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Note on Dr Glaisher's Paper on a Theorem in Definite Integration.

[From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics, vol. x. (1870), pp. 355, 356.]

IT is worth noticing that under the case when $\phi = 1$ may be proved independently of the general formula with Θ_1 for (1) the equation

$$s = ax - \frac{a_1}{a - b_1}x - \frac{a_2}{a - b_2}x - \dots - \frac{a_n}{a - b_n}x \dots,$$

is $(sx - r)(sx - b_1)(sx - b_2) \dots (sx - b_n) \dots = 0$, and has $s + 1$ roots, say $x_1, x_2, \dots, x_{n+1}$, where

$$x_1 = x, \quad x_2 = a - b_1 + b_1, \quad \dots, \quad x_{n+1} = a - b_n + b_n;$$

and (2) the equation

$$r = -\frac{a_1}{a - b_1}x - \frac{a_2}{a - b_2}x - \dots - \frac{a_n}{a - b_n}x \dots,$$

is $r(x - b_1)(x - b_2) \dots (x - b_n) \dots = 0$, and has n roots $x_1, x_2, \dots, x_n$ where

$$x_1 = x_1 - a_1, \quad x_2 = b_1 + b_2, \quad \dots, \quad x_n = \frac{x_{n-1} + b_{n-1} + b_n}{a_n};$$

whence

$$f dx_1 + f dx_2 + \dots + f dx_{n+1} = 0 \quad \text{in the first case}$$

and

$$nf(a, b)(x_n, x_{n-1}, \dots, x_2, x_1)' = 0 \quad \text{in the second}$$

[which are the two formulæ in question]

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On the Quartic Surfaces $(\ast U, V, W)^2 = 0$.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. X. (1871), pp. 15–25.]

AMONG the surfaces of the form in question are included the reciprocals of several interesting surfaces of the orders 6, 8, 9, 10, and 12, viz.

Order 6, parabolic ring,

8, elliptic ring,

9, centro-surface of a paraboloid,

10, parallel surface of a paraboloid,

envelope of planes through the points of an ellipsoid at right angles to the radius vectors from the centre,

12, centro-surface of an ellipsoid,

parallel surface of an ellipsoid.

I propose to consider these surfaces, not at present in any detail, but merely for the purpose of presenting them in connexion with each other and with the present theory. It will be convenient to use homogeneous equations, but for the surcinal interpretation the coordinate W or w may be considered as equal to unity; I have not thought it necessary to so adjust the constants that the equations shall be homogeneous in regard to the constants; this case of course be done without difficulty, and in many cases it would be analytically advantageous to make the change.

I take throughout (X, Y, Z, W) for the coordinates of a point on the quartic surface (so that (X, Y, W) is, the equation $(\ast U, V, W)^2 = 0$ are to be considered as quartic functions of (X, Y, Z, W)); reserving (x, y, z, w) for the coordinates of a point on the reciprocal surface of the order 6, 8, 9, 10, or 12. The reciprocation is performed in regard to the imaginary sphere $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 + w^2 = 0$; the relation between

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the coordinates (X, Y, Z, W) and (x, y, z, w) is then $Xx + Yy + Zz + Ww = 0$, and the equation $(X, Y, Z, W) = 0$ is the equation in point-coordinates of the quartic surface, or in line-coordinates of the reciprocal surface; and similarly the equation $(x, y, z, w)^n = 0$ is the equation in point-coordinates of the reciprocal surface, or in line-coordinates of the quartic surface.

Parabolic ring, or envelope of a sphere of constant radius having its centre on a parabola.

Taking k for the radius of the sphere, and $x = 0$, $y^2 = ax$ for the equations of the parabola, then the coordinates of a point on the parabola are $a\theta^2$, $2a\theta$, 0 , where θ is a variable parameter. The equation of the sphere therefore is

$$(x - a\theta w)^2 + (y - 2a\theta w)^2 + z^2 - k^2 w^2 = 0,$$

and the ring is the envelope of this sphere.

The reciprocal of the sphere is

$$k^2(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) - (a\theta^2 X + 2a\theta Y + W)^2 = 0;$$

writing this in the form

$$a\theta^2 X + 2a\theta Y + W = k\sqrt{1}(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) = 0,$$

and taking the envelope in regard to θ , we have

$$X\{W + k\sqrt{1}(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)\} - aY^2 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(aY^2 - XW)^2 = k^2 X^2 (X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)$$

for the equation of the quartic surface. This has the form $X = 0, V = 0$ for a tangential line, but I am not in possession of a theory enabling me thence to infer that the parabolic ring is of the order 4.

To show that it is so, I have to find (x, y, z, w) which satisfy the equation of the variable sphere

$$(x - a\theta w)^2 + (y - 2a\theta w)^2 + z^2 - k^2 w^2 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(A, B, C, D, E)(\theta, 1)^4 = 0,$$

where

$$A = a^2 w^2,$$

$$B = 0,$$

$$C = a(2aw^2 - ax),$$

$$D = -4ayw,$$

$$E = x^2 + y^2 + z^2 - k^2 w^2.$$

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Then $I = 3a^4w^2E$, $J = a^6w^6C$, and the equation is $I^3 - J^2 = 0$, viz. this is

$$(Ax^2 + 3y^2 - 3aw^2x + 3y^2 - 4xy)^3 - \{(3aw - x)(3y^2 + 3y^2 - 6wx - 4ayx) - 27a^2y^2wx\}^2(Ew - xw)^2 = 0,$$

or, as this may also be written,

$$(Ax^2 + 3y^2 - 3aw^2x)^3 - \{(3aw - x)(3y^2 + 3y^2 - 6wx - 4ayx) - 27a^2y^2wx\}^2(Ew - xw)^2 = 0.$$

Developing, the whole divides by 27, and the equation of the ring finally is

$$\begin{aligned} (y^2 - 6awx)^3(y^2 + xw) = & -3aw^2\{2x^2 - 2axw + 3aw^2(y - xw)(y^2 - 2yw)\}(z^2 + w^2) \\ & + \{3y^2 + y^2(2x - 2a)w + 24a^2(zw^2 + aw^2z) + 16a^2w^4(z^2 - xw)(z^2 - 8axw + 4a^2w^2)\}(z^2 - kw^2) \\ & + \{(2y^2 + axw(z^2 - kw^2))^2\}(z^2 - kw^2)^3 \end{aligned}$$

which is a quartic surface having for nodal conics

$$(y^2 - 6awx = 0, \quad z^2 + w^2 = 0), \quad (Z = 0, \quad x = w = 0),$$

the line at infinity being a torsal line.

Elliptic ring, or envelope of a sphere of constant radius having its centre on an ellipse.

Taking k for the radius of the sphere, and $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$ for the equations of the ellipse, the coordinates of a point on the ellipse are $a \cos \theta$, $b \sin \theta$, 0; hence the equation of the variable sphere is

$$(x - aw \cos \theta)^2 + (y - bw \sin \theta)^2 + z^2 - k^2w^2 = 0.$$

The reciprocal of the sphere is

$$k^2(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) - (aX \cos \theta + bY \sin \theta + W)^2 = 0;$$

viz. writing this under the form

$$aX \cos \theta + bY \sin \theta + W = k\sqrt{(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)},$$

and taking the envelope in regard to θ , we have

$$\sqrt{(a^2X^2 + b^2Y^2)} = W + k\sqrt{(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)};$$

viz. this is

$$(a^2X^2 + b^2Y^2) + W^2 + k^2(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) - 2Wk\sqrt{(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)} = 0;$$

or

$$\{(a^2 + k^2)X^2 + (b^2 + k^2)Y^2 + k^2Z^2 + W^2\}^2 = 4W^2k^2(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2),$$

for the equation of the quartic surface. This has the form $X = 0$, $V = 0$ for a tangential line, but I am not in possession of a theory enabling me thence to infer that the elliptic ring is of the order 4.

To show that it is so, I have to find (x, y, z, w) which satisfy the equation of the variable sphere

$$(x - aw \cos \theta)^2 + (y - bw \sin \theta)^2 + z^2 - k^2w^2 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(A, B, C, D, E)(t, 1)^4 = 0,$$

where

$$A = 0,$$

$$B = 0,$$

$$C = a(2aw^2 - ax),$$

$$D = -4byw,$$

$$E = 2(a^2 + b^2)w^2 + 2(x^2 + y^2 + z^2 - k^2w^2).$$

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For this purpose reverting to the equation

$$(x - aw \cos \theta + (y - bw \sin \theta + z^2 - k^2 w^2) = 0,$$

this may be written

$$A \cos 2\theta + B \sin 2\theta + C \cos \theta + D \sin \theta + E = 0,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} A &= \frac{1}{2}(a^2 - b^2)w^2, \\ B &= 0, \\ C &= -4axw, \\ D &= -4byw, \\ E &= \frac{1}{2}(a^2 + b^2)w^2 + 2(x^2 + y^2 + z^2 - k^2 w^2), \end{aligned}$$

and the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} &12A(A - B) - 3(C^2 + D^2) + 4E^2 \\ &= \{12A^2(C^2 - D^2) - 24BCD - 3(C^2 + D^2)^2 + 4E^2(E - 8A^2)\}^2; \end{aligned}$$

or say

$$\{12A^2 + 3(C^2 + D^2) + 4E^2\}^3 - 27\{A(C^2 - D^2) - 2BCD - 3E(C^2 + D^2) + 8AE^2\}^2 = 0.$$

This is of the order 12, but it is easy to see that the terms in A^2 and $E^2(C^2 + D^2)$ disappear from the equation, all the other terms divide by w^2 ; and the equation is thus of the order 8.

The equation may be obtained somewhat differently, as follows. The equation of the variable sphere is

$$(x - aw)^2 + (y - bw)^2 + z^2 - k^2 w^2 = 0,$$

where (a, β) may subject to the condition $\frac{a^2}{a^2} + \frac{b^2}{b^2} = 1$. We have therefore

$$\frac{x - aw}{(x - aw) da} + \frac{y - bw}{(y - bw) db} = 0,$$

$$\beta da = \frac{a a}{a^2 + b^2} = -\frac{b}{a} da;$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} aw &= \frac{a^2 x}{a^2 + b^2}, & x - aw &= \frac{b^2 x}{a^2 + b^2}, \\ \beta w &= \frac{b^2 y}{a^2 + b^2}, & y - bw &= \frac{a^2 y}{a^2 + b^2}. \end{aligned}$$

Consequently

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{a^2 x^2}{(a^2 + b^2)^2} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(a^2 + b^2)^2} - w^2 &= 0, \\ \frac{a^2 x^2}{(a^2 + b^2)^2} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(a^2 + b^2)^2} - w^2 &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

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The quartic surface is consequently the envelope of the sphere

$$\frac{(a+b)^2}{a}x^2 + \frac{(b+c)^2}{b}y^2 + 2bz^2 - 2aw^2 = 0,$$

viz. this is

$$b\left(\frac{1}{a} - \frac{1}{a}\right)x^2 + 2\theta(x^2 + y^2 + z^2) + 2aX - 2bW = 0.$$

Hence the quartic surface is

$$\left(\frac{x^2}{a} - \frac{y^2}{a}\right)(aX^2 + bY^2 - 2ZW) = (X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$X^2Y^2(ab + cb) - 2ZW(bX^2 + aY^2) - 2abZ(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) - aBcZ = 0.$$

This has four nodes; viz. considering the equations

$$\frac{X}{a} + \frac{Y}{b} = 0, \quad aX^2 + bY^2 - 2ZW = 0, \quad X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2 = 0,$$

these give the quad. $X = 0, Y = 0, Z = 0$ four times, and four other points which are the nodes in question; the point $(X = 0, Y = 0, Z = 0)$ is a singular point of a higher order; the deduction caused by these singularities should be $= 8 + 19$, so as to make the order of the surface of curves of $36 - 8 - 19 = 12$, but it is the reduction on account of the point $(X = 0, Y = 0, Z = 0)$ must be $= 19$; but it is not by any means obvious how this is so.

Parallel surface of the paraboloid.

This is given, Salmon's *Solid Geometry*, 2nd Edit., pp. 146 and 148, [Ed. 4, p. 180], for the paraboloid $aX^2 + bY^2 + 2ZW = 0$, as the envelope of the quartic surface

$$\frac{a}{aw+1}X^2 + \frac{b}{bw+1}Y^2 + 2W(\theta - r^2w + r^2)w^2 = 0.$$

The reciprocal quartic is thus the envelope of

$$\frac{1}{a}x^2 + \frac{1}{b}y^2 + \frac{1}{a^2}z^2 + \frac{1}{a+r^2w}w^2 - w^2 = 0,$$

that is,

$$(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) + \frac{1}{b}\left(\frac{X^2}{a} - \frac{Y^2}{b} - \frac{2Z}{c}W\right) = 0;$$

whence the equation is

$$\frac{1}{b^2}(X^2 - Y^2)\left(\frac{X^2}{a} - \frac{Y^2}{b} - \frac{2Z}{c}\right) = 0,$$

viz. this is a quartic having the nodal lines

$$Z = X = 0, \quad Z = Y = 0$$

the circle must be equal, and the distance of the centre from the line of centres, and if the radii are r, r' , is readily found to be

$$(a - x)^2 + 2(r + r'),$$

suppose in general, that spheres any two contain the point P in the intersection of the points of P in regard to the two given conics respectively; then if P describes

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Envelope of the planes through the points of an ellipsoid at right angles to the radius vectors from the centre.

This is given in my paper “Note on a Surface,” in the *Annales de Matématique*, t. I. (1859), [206], as the envelope of the quartic surface

$$\frac{x^2}{1+\theta a} + \frac{y^2}{1+\theta b} + \frac{z^2}{1+\theta c} - \theta a^2 = 0.$$

The reciprocal quartic is thus the envelope of

$$\left(2 - \frac{x^2}{a}\right) X^2 + \left(1 - \frac{y^2}{b}\right) Y^2 + \left(1 - \frac{z^2}{c}\right) Z^2 - \frac{1}{a} W^2 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\theta \left(\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c} - \frac{1}{c} W^2 \right) - (X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) = 0;$$

viz. it is

$$W^2 = \frac{X^2 - aY^2}{X^2 - aY^2 + Z^2} = \frac{Y^2}{X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2} = \frac{Z}{X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2} = 0 \quad \text{for } X, Y, Z,$$

of the original $\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c} = 1$; this is obvious geometrically inasmuch as the reciprocal of the variable plane is the inverse of the point on the ellipsoid.

The quartic surface has the nodal conic

$$W = 0, \quad aX^2 + bY^2 + cZ^2 = 0;$$

and also the node $X = 0, Y = 0, Z = 0$; there is a reduction in the order of the reciprocal surface a reduction $24 + 2 = 26$, or the order of the reciprocal surface is $= 10$.

Centro-surface of the ellipsoid.

Writing the equation of the ellipsoid in the form $\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} - w^2 = 0$, the centro-surface is given as the envelope of the quartic surface

$$\frac{x^2\theta^2}{(a+\theta)^2} + \frac{y^2\theta^2}{(b+\theta)^2} + \frac{z^2\theta^2}{(c+\theta)^2} - w^2 = 0.$$

(Salmon, [Ed. 2], p. 106; [Ed. 4, p. 177]), and hence the reciprocal quartic surface is the envelope of

$$\left(a + \frac{a^2}{\theta}\right) X^2 + \left(b + \frac{b^2}{\theta}\right) Y^2 + \left(c + \frac{c^2}{\theta}\right) Z^2 - W^2 = 0,$$

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in regard to the variable parameter θ , viz. the equation is

$$\left(\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c}\right)(aX^2 + bY^2 + cZ^2 - W^2) - (X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) = 0,$$

(see Salmon, [Ed. 2], p. 144 [Ed. 4, p. 172]). It hence at once appears, that the quartic surface has 12 nodes, viz. these are the four angles of the fundamental tetrahedron ($XYZW$), and the eight points

$$\begin{aligned}\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c} &= 0, \\ X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2 &= 0, \quad W = 0, \\ aX^2 + bY^2 + cZ^2 - W^2 &= 0;\end{aligned}$$

or writing as is convenient to do,

$$(a, \beta, \gamma) = (b - c, c - a, a - b), \quad \alpha + \beta + \gamma = 0,$$

these are the eight points

$$(a, \beta, \gamma : \xi : \eta : \zeta) = 0,$$

the order of the reciprocal of the quartic surface is then $36 - 12 = 24$, which is in fact the order of the surface of centres.

The equation of the centro-surface is given, Salmon, [Ed. 2], p. 121, and *Quart. Math. Jour.*, t. IX. (1858), p. 220, in the form

$$(\theta, \beta, \gamma : \xi, \eta : \zeta)^4 = 0,$$

where ξ, η, ζ stand for ax, by, cz, bz ; it is therefore of the degree 18 in regard to (x, y, z, w) , which is the equation of the surface, but it must contain in itself the equation w^4 , and the order of the curve will be $20 - 6 = 14$.

Parallel surface of the ellipsoid.

This is given, Salmon, [Ed. 2], p. 148 [Ed. 4, p. 178], as the envelope of the quartic surface

$$\frac{a^2 X^2}{a^2 - r^2 w^2} + \frac{b^2 Y^2}{b^2 - r^2 w^2} + \frac{c^2 Z^2}{c^2 - r^2 w^2} = \left(1 - \frac{W^2}{w^2}\right) w^2.$$

The reciprocal quartic is thus the envelope of

$$(a^2 \theta X^2 + b^2 \theta Y^2 + c^2 \theta Z^2 + (a^2 - r^2) W^2 - W^2 + r^2 W^2)^2 = 0,$$

or writing $D + r^2 = \theta$, this is

$$(a^2 - 4\theta + b^2 + c^2 \theta) - (\theta - a^2) Y^2 - (\theta - c^2) Z^2 - (\theta - r^2) W^2 - W^2 - \left(1 - \frac{r^2}{\theta}\right) W^2 = 0.$$

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or, what is the same thing,

$$bX(bX - Z) + \{w^2 - r^2\theta + ay\}\{x^2 + (a+b)Y^2 + (a+c)Z^2 + (a-r^2)W^2 - W^2\} = 0,$$

whence the equation is

$$\{(a^2 - bY)(X^2 + (a-b)Y^2 + (a-c)Z^2 - W^2) + 2bW^2(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) = 0.$$

viz. this is a quartic having the nodal

$$W = 0, \quad (a^2 - bY)X^2 + (a-b)Y^2 + (a-c)Z^2 = 0.$$

The order of the reciprocal or parallel surface is then $36 - 24, = 12$, as it should be. The nodal conic of the quartic surface is the reciprocal of a tangent cone of the ellipsoid having a non-cyclic quadric cone, vertex the centre, in the parallel surface; this cone is imaginary for the ellipsoid, but real for either of the hyperboloids, and the existence in the case of the hyperboloid is readily perceived.

Reverting to the equation

$$\frac{a^2}{a^2 + \theta}X^2 + \frac{b^2}{b^2 + \theta}Y^2 + \frac{c^2}{c^2 + \theta}Z^2 - \left(1 + \frac{r^2W^2}{\theta}\right)w^2 = 0,$$

or say

$$(a^2 - P)X^2 + (b^2 - P)Y^2 + (c^2 - P)Z^2 - r^2(a^2 - P)(b^2 - P)(c^2 - P) = 0$$

this is

$$-w^2(a^2 - P)(b^2 - P)(c^2 - P) - r^2(a^2 - P)(b^2 - P)(c^2 - P) - P(a^2 - P)(b^2 - P)(c^2 - P) = 0,$$

where putting for shortness

$$\begin{aligned} u &= a^2 + b^2 + c^2, \\ \beta &= b^2c^2 + c^2a^2 + a^2b^2, \\ \gamma &= a^2b^2c^2, \\ b &= aP^2 - b^2, \\ p &= a^2 + y^2 + z^2, \\ q &= b^2c^2x^2 + a^2c^2y^2 + a^2b^2z^2, \\ r &= a^2b^2c^2w^2 - r^2a^2b^2c^2 + a^2b^2c^2, \end{aligned}$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} A &= 12n^2, \\ B &= 9aw^2 - 2p, \\ C &= 12n - 4ap, \\ D &= 3aw - 3r, \\ E &= 12r^2. \end{aligned}$$

The equation of the parallel surface is

$$(AE - 4BD + 3C^2)^3 = 27(ACE - AD^2 - B^2E + 2BCD - C^3)^2.$$

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It is remarked (Salmon, [Ed. 2], p. 148 [Ed. 4, p. 176]) that there is in the plane $z = 0$, a nodal conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2+r^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2+r^2} - 1 = 0$, the complete section being made up of this conic twice, and of the curve of the eighth order which is the parallel curve of the ellipse $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} - 1 = 0$; the like is of course the case as to the sections by the other two principal planes $x = 0$, $y = 0$. For the section by the plane $w = 0$ (or plane infinity) we have at once $p^2 + (qw^2 = 0$, where observe that

$$\begin{aligned} q^2 - 4pr &= \{(a^2 + b^2 + c^2)x^2 + (b^2c^2 + c^2a^2 + a^2b^2)y^2 + \dots\}^2 \\ &= (1, 1, 1, -1, -1, -1)(b^2 + c^2)y^2z^2, (c^2 - a^2)^2z^2x^2, (a^2 - b^2)^2x^2y^2) \\ &= ac(x^2 - y^2 - z^2 + b^2 + c^2(x^2 - y^2))^2, \end{aligned}$$

which has reduced to a sum of squares with positive signs.

The section is thus made up of two conics, each twice, and of four right lines: viz. the conics are $z^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$, this section at infinity of the sphere, the section at infinity of the ellipsoid; and the lines are

$$(\sqrt{X^2 - aZ^2} = 0, \quad (\sqrt{X^2 - aZ^2} + \sqrt{X^2 - bZ^2}, X^2 - aZ^2 = 0)$$

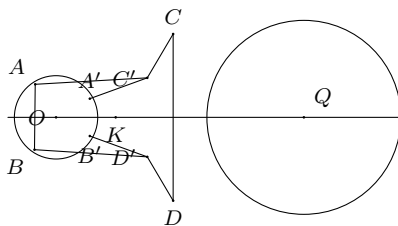
viz. those are the common tangents of the two conics. The circle at infinity is a nodal conic on the surface, which has thus 4 nodal conics.

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Note on a Relation between Two Circles.

[From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 82, 83.]

CONSIDER any two circles O, Q ; and let AC, BD, AB, BC be the common tangents touching the circles in the points $A, A_1, B, B_1, C, C_1, D, D_1$: the locus of a point P such that the pairs of tangents from it to the two circles respectively form a harmonic pencil, is a conic (locus of the points $A, A_1, B, B_1, C, C_1, D, D_1$); but this conic may break up into two lines, viz. if (as in the figure) the points A, B, D, D are in a line, then the points C, C', A', B' will be in a symmetrically situated line, and the conic breaks up into this pair of lines, meeting suppose in K . The condition



for this, if a, c' are the distances of the centres from a fixed point in the line of centres, and if the radii are r, r' , is readily found to be

$$(a - c')^2 = 2(r^2 + r'^2).$$

Suppose in general, that lines any two contain the point P in the intersection of the points of P in regard to the two given conics respectively; then, if P describes

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a line, the locus of P is a conic passing through the three conjugate points of the given conic, if, however, the line which is the locus of P pass through one of the conjugate points, then the conic the locus of P' breaks up into a pair of lines: one of them a fixed line through the other two conjugate points; that is, the locus of P' is through the demonstrated conjugate points. That is, if the locus of P be a line through a conjugate point, the locus of P' is a line through the same conjugate point; but in every other case the locus of P' is a conic.

Reverting to the figure of the two circles, in order that it may be possible that the two lines AD and BC may be loci of points P , P' , related as above, it is necessary that K shall be a conjugate point of the two circles; that is, if the two circles intersect in points A , X lying symmetrically in the line of centres, then K must be the anti-points of A , X ; what is the same thing the chord AX shall be one of the same mentioned relation. And it then appears that given two circles, the necessary and sufficient conditions for the coexistence of the properties mentioned in the theorem are that they shall be equal circles touching each other.

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On the Porism of the In-and-Circumscribed Polygon, and the (2, 2) Correspondence of Points on a Conic.*[From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 83–91.]*

THE present paper includes, as will at once be seen, much that is perfectly well known; but the separate theories regarded it seemed to me, to be put together; and there are, particularly as regards the unsymmetrical case afterwards referred to, some results which I believe to be new.

The porism of the in-and-circumscribed polygon has its foundation in the theory of the symmetrical (2, 2) correspondence of points on a conic; viz. a (2, 2) correspondence is such that to any given position of either point there correspond two positions of the other point; and is a symmetrical (2, 2) correspondence either point indifferently may be considered as the first point and the other of them will then be the second point of the correspondence. Or, what is the same thing, if x, y are the parameters which serve to determine the two points, then x, y are connected by an equation of the form $(\alpha x, 1\alpha y, 1)^2 = 0$; or, as it will always thus, whatever the parameters (x, y) . In the case of such symmetrical relation it is easy to show that the line joining the two points envelopes a conic. For the relation may be expressed in the form $(\alpha x + y, x + y, xy)^2 = 0$; we may imagine the coordinates (P, Q, R) of each manner that for the point (x) on the first conic the corresponding values (P, Q, R) for and for the point (y) , $P : Q : R = 1 : y : y^2$; the equation of the line joining the two points is then

$$\begin{vmatrix} P & Q & R \\ 1 & x & x^2 \\ 1 & y & y^2 \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

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that is

$$Pxy - Q(x + y) + R = 0,$$

or representing this by the equation

$$PL + QM + R = 0,$$

we have $L : -2 = -y : x + y - 1$; and consequently (L, M) are connected by a quadric relation $(*L, 1)^2 = 0$, that is, the line envelopes a conic.

The locus, $(F, P, Q, R = 0$, where symmetrical or not, leads us to the following theorem of X, Y are quartic functions of a respectively; viz. these are unlike as like functions of the two variables according as the integral equation is not or is symmetrical. In the present case, however, where X is supposed to be the same function of a variable, but does the equation be a connection. In every chord through any two points of the conic, then the relation is obviously

$$\frac{dx}{\sqrt{(X)}} \pm \frac{dy}{\sqrt{(Y)}} = 0$$

where X, Y are quartic functions of x, y respectively, viz. this is also the symmetric relation. In the case of the in-and-circumscribed polygon there is an unsymmetric relation, but I cannot, however, propose to recall the integral equation in this case.

Attending now to the symmetrical case; if A and B are corresponding points, then the corresponding points of B are A and a new point C ; those of C are B and a new point D , and so on; so that the points form a series $A, B, C, D, \dots$: and the polynomial of A is, if a given position of B this series closes at a certain term, for instance, if $D = A$, then it will always thus close; whatever the position of the point on the conic, the integral equation

$$\Pi(y) - \Pi(x) = 0,$$

this equation must be a transformation of the original equation $(\ast \check{a} x, 1 \check{a} y, 1)^2 = 0$, and equally with it represent the relation between the parameters x, y of the two points A, B ; the constant of integration k of course be determined according as the coefficients of the form of the unsymmetrical case is so on.

Hence forming the equations for the correspondences $B, C; C, D; \dots$, and assuming that the series closes at $D = A$, we have

$$\Pi(y) - \Pi(x) = \Pi(z),$$

$$\Pi(z) - \Pi(y) = \Pi(z),$$

$$\Pi(z) - \Pi(z) = \Pi(z);$$

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On the Porism of the In-and-Circumscribed Polygon (continued).

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Now starting from the differential equation

$$\frac{dx}{\sqrt{(a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4}} \pm \frac{dy}{\sqrt{(a, b, c, d, e \check{a} y, 1)^4}} = 0,$$

the integral equation is known to be

$$\frac{\sqrt{(a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4} - \sqrt{(a, b, c, d, e \check{a} y, 1)^4}}{x - y} = \frac{1}{2}(a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, y, 1)^2,$$

where θ is the constant of integration. Writing, for shortness, $X = (a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4$, $Y = (a, b, c, d, e \check{a} y, 1)^4$, this is

$$X + Y - 2\sqrt{(XY)} = a(x^2 - y^2)^2 + 4b(x - y)(x^2 - y^2) + 6\theta(x - y)^2,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} a(x + y)^4 - 2\sqrt{(XY)} &= a(x^2 - y^2)^2 - 4a(x - y)(x^3 - y^3) + 6\theta(x - y)^2, \\ &+ 4b(x^3 + y^3) \\ &+ 6c(x^2 + y^2) \\ &+ 4d(x + y) \\ &+ 2e, \end{aligned}$$

viz. this gives

$$\begin{aligned} \sqrt{(XY)} &= ax^2y^2 \\ &+ 2b(x^2y + xy^2) \\ &+ 3c(x^2 + y^2) \\ &+ 3d^2xy - 3\theta \\ &+ 2d(x + y) \\ &+ e, \end{aligned}$$

and, rationalising, the integral equation becomes

$$\begin{aligned} &= 6a\theta x^2y^2 \\ &- 4abxy(x + y) \\ &- ac(x + y)^2 \\ &+ 4b^2xy \\ &+ 12bcxy(x + y) + 12bdxy(x + y) \\ &- 9c^2xy \\ &+ 6ce(x + y)^2 - 18cd(x + y) \\ &- 12cd(x + y) \\ &+ 9d^2(x + y)^2 - 12d\theta(x + y) - 6ed + 4d^2 = 0. \end{aligned}$$

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or, as it may be written,

$$\begin{aligned}
 & xy^2(3\theta - 6ad) \\
 & + (x^2y + xy^2)(-4ad + 12bc - 12bd) \\
 & + (x^2 + y^2)(-ae - 3c^2 - 6ec\theta + 4d^2) \\
 & + xy(-2ae + 3bd - 12ec - 4be) \\
 & + (x + y)(-2be + 12bd - 6d^2) \\
 & + 4d^2 - 6ed = 0.
 \end{aligned}$$

Comparing this with the original integral equation $V = 0$, and the form of differential equation deduced therefrom, we ought to have therefore

$$\begin{aligned}
 & [(4b^2 - 8ad)x^2 + (-2ae + 4bd)x + (-ae + 4bd - 3c^2)]ay^2 \\
 & + [(-ae + 4bd - 4ce)x + (-2ae + 4bd - 4de) + (3d^2 - 6ed)]y \\
 & + [(-ae + 4bd - 3c^2)x + (3d^2 - 6ed) + (4e^2 - 8d\theta)]
 \end{aligned}$$

= multiple of X ,

= $(-4ax^2 - 4bx + 2cax)(\theta x + (3a - 6cx) - (-ae + 4bd - 3c^2))$, by comparing the coefficients of x^4 . I obtain this otherwise: Write

$$V = aC + 6\beta H,$$

then, forming the Hessian of V , we have

$$\square V = -aH^2 + (a^2I + (Ja\theta)U,$$

or

$$= aH^2 - \frac{3IJ(\theta)}{8}(\theta)(V - aC) + (aI + (Ja\theta)U,$$

that is,

$$aJV + (-3a^2J)V - \frac{2}{8}(aH - \frac{3J}{8})(aH) + \frac{3J^2(\theta)}{8}U(8H - aC) + (aJV + (Ja\theta)U,$$

viz.

$$K = -\frac{3J\theta}{8}(\theta) - aH,$$

this is

$$(aJV + (Ja\theta)V + (J^2I)V - (a\theta\theta)V + a\theta^2aV + \frac{3J}{8}(\theta) = (3aV)(-\theta U,$$

so that the components are

$$V = aV + 6\beta H,$$

$$V' = -aC + 6\beta H,$$

where $a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4, +(a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, y) - 1)^2, 4ax + 4bx + 6cy - 4dy - e$, or $-d^2(c, 1)^2$,

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viz. the components are

$$\begin{array}{lll} (aa + b\check{a}(ax - bc), & ab + bd(ax - bc), & ae + bx + 2bd - 3c^2(\check{a}x, 1)^2, \\ (ab + bd(ax - bc), & ac + bx + 2bd - 3c^2(\check{a}x, 1)^2, & bd + bx + x_{1c}^2 J_x, \\ (ac + bx + 2bd - 3c^2(\check{a}x, 1)^2, & bd + bx + x_{1c}^2 J_x, & ae + bx + x_{1c}^2 J_x, \end{array}$$

where as before

$$K = \frac{8(a^2 - 3J\theta)}{a}.$$

I assume

$$\begin{aligned} B &= -\frac{1}{a}, \quad b' = bB - \frac{1}{a} \quad K = 3\{4a^2 - 6b\theta - 3a^2c^2\}, \\ ax + b\check{a}(ax - bc) &= a(x - bc) + ax(b - bx) - bx, \\ ab + bd(ax - bc) &= a(x - bc) + ax(b - bx) - bxc, \\ ae + bx + 2bd - 3c^2(\check{a}x, 1)^2 &= a(x - bc) + ax(b - bx) - bxc - bxd, \\ ae + bx + 2bd - 3c^2(\check{a}x, 1)^2 &= a(x - bc) + ax(b - bx) - bxc - bxd - bxe, \\ ax + b\check{a}(2bd - 3c^2)\check{a}J_x &= 4bK - 4bex + a(2bd - 3c^2)(\check{a}x, 1)^2 - \frac{1}{a}bK - 3bex, \\ &= -be - 12bc + 6b(8bd - 3c^2 + 4d\theta) \\ &= a(b\theta - 3b\theta + 3bax) - \frac{1}{2}(b\theta\theta + ac^2 + b\theta)f', \\ &= a(b\theta - 3b\theta + 3bax) - \frac{1}{2}(b\theta\theta + ac^2 + b\theta)f', \\ &= aa + b - 12acd + 6a^2ec, \end{aligned}$$

agreeing with the former result.

I return to the general form

$$\begin{aligned} &\eta(\theta', b, c \check{a}x, 1)^4 \\ &+ 2g(a', b', c' \check{a}x, 1)^2 \\ &+ (a'', b'', c'' \check{a}x, 1)^4 = 0 \end{aligned}$$

giving

$$\frac{dx}{\sqrt{(a, b, c, d, e \check{a}x, 1)^4}} \pm \frac{dy}{\sqrt{(a, b, c, d, e \check{a}y, 1)^4}} = \frac{dy}{\sqrt{(a', b', c' \check{a}y, 1)^2(a'', b'', c'' \check{a}y, 1)^2}}.$$

Operate a linear transformation on this, a say

$$x = \frac{\lambda x' + \mu}{\nu x' + \rho},$$

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the new coefficients are

$$\begin{aligned} & (a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4, \quad (a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4, \quad (a, b, c, d, e \check{a} x, 1)^4, \\ & (a', b', c' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \quad (a', b', c' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \quad (a', b', c' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \\ & (a'', b'', c'' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \quad (a'', b'', c'' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \quad (a'', b'', c'' \check{a} x, 1)^2; \end{aligned}$$

assume now

$$\begin{aligned} a'\lambda + (b' - c')\mu - ca &= 0, & ba\mu &= 0, \\ (a' + b')\lambda - bc + c\mu &= 0, & ca\mu &= a(a'\mu + 6c'\mu - bc) = 0, \\ b' & & & = c' = 6c\mu = 0; \end{aligned}$$

then it is easy to show that

$$\begin{aligned} (a, b, c \check{a} x, p\mu \check{a} x, 1)^4 &= (a', c' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \\ (a', b', c' \check{a} x, p\mu \check{a} x, 1)^2 &= (a', c' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \\ (a, b, c \check{a} x, p\mu \check{a} x, 1)^4 &= (a', c' \check{a} x, 1)^2, \end{aligned}$$

and the equations give

$$\begin{vmatrix} a' & b' - c' & \mu & a \\ b' + c' & b' - c' & \mu & ba \\ a' + b' & a' - b' & ca\mu & a \\ b'' & c'' & a'' - c'' & 1 \end{vmatrix} = 0;$$

that is

$$\begin{aligned} & (a'c'' - b''^2 + a''b'^2)(a'c''(c' - b')) - 2b'^2 \\ & \quad - (c'^2c'' - b'c''c''c'' - b'^2) \\ & \quad + a'c''(a''a' - a''b'c' - a'b'c) \\ & \quad + a'c''(a'c''^2c''c'' - b'^2c'') \\ & \quad + a'c''(a'b'^2 + a''b'') \\ & = 0, \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned} (c'c'' - b''^2)(a'c'' - b''^2) &= \frac{1}{4}b'^2 & a, \quad b, & c \\ & + ca''c''^2 & a', \quad b', & c' \\ + ca'c''^2 - 2(c''^2 - c'') & & a'', \quad b'', & c'' \\ & + c''(c''^2 - c'') \\ & + 2bc(b - c) \\ + 2bc(b - c)(c'' - c''^2) & & & \\ + 4b'c''(b'c'^2 - c'^2) & & & \\ + 8c'(b'^2 - c''^2) + d\theta & = 0. \end{aligned}$$

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If the original matrix be symmetrical, that is

$$(\beta - b')^2 + (a\mu - b')(c\mu - f'') = \begin{vmatrix} a & b & f \\ h & b & f \\ p & f & c \end{vmatrix}, \quad \text{this is}$$

$$\begin{aligned} c(\beta - b')^2 + (a\mu - b')(c\mu - f'') &= -\partial F \begin{vmatrix} a & b & g \\ h & b & f \\ p & f & c \end{vmatrix} \\ &+ h^2(-c\eta) \\ &+ b^2(-c\mu - g^2 - 2fh) \\ &+ f^2(-c\nu) \\ &+ 2h(c^2g + ph) \\ &+ 2f^2(ch + ck) \\ &+ 2hc(fp + ch) + 6h = 0, \end{aligned}$$

that is

$$\begin{aligned} (b - g)(b - b')^2 + (a + b'')(c\beta + p) + 2(cp^2 + ch^2 - 2bfh) \\ = 2F(abc - aef^2 - bg^2 - ch^2 + 2fgh) + b'(4h^2 - bf^2 + bh) - cf'' + b^2 = 0, \end{aligned}$$

multiplied by

$$\theta + b - g = 0,$$

viz. the equation in θ is

$$(\theta + b - g)(b'\theta^2 + (b - c)\theta + (4fh - bcb + hc(2g - b) - c)) + (b'^2 - cab) + 2(cb^2 + ch^2 - 2hf)\beta = 0.$$

490. ON A PROBLEM OF ELIMINATION.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 99–101.]

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I write

$$\begin{aligned} P &= (a, \dots \wp x, y, z)^k, & Q &= (a', \dots \wp x, y, z)^k, \\ U &= (\alpha, \dots \wp x, y, z)^m, & V &= (\beta, \dots \wp x, y, z)^n, \end{aligned}$$

and I seek for the form of the relation between the coefficients $(a, \dots), (a', \dots), (\alpha, \dots), (\beta, \dots)$, in order that there may exist in the pencil

$$\lambda P + \mu Q = 0$$

a curve passing through two of the intersections of the curves $U = 0, V = 0$.

The ratio $\lambda : \mu$ may be determined so as that the curve $\lambda P + \mu Q = 0$ shall pass through one of the intersections of the curves $U = 0, V = 0$; or, what is the same thing, so as that the three curves shall have a common point; the condition for this is

$$\text{Reslt.}(\lambda P + \mu Q, U, V) = 0,$$

a condition of the form

$$(\lambda a + \mu a', \dots)^{mn} (\alpha, \dots)^{kn} (\beta, \dots)^{km} = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(a, \dots, a', \dots)^{mn} (\alpha, \dots)^{kn} (\beta, \dots)^{km} (\lambda, \mu)^{mn} = 0,$$

which, for shortness, may be written

$$(A, \dots \wp \lambda, \mu)^{mn} = 0.$$

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Suppose this equation has equal roots, then we have

$$\text{Disct. Reslt.}(\lambda P + \mu Q, U, V) = 0,$$

the discriminant being taken in regard to λ, μ . This is of the form

$$(A, \dots)^{2(mn-1)} = 0;$$

that is

$$(a, \dots, a', \dots)^{2mn(mn-1)}(\alpha, \dots)^{2kn(mn-1)}(\beta, \dots)^{2km(mn-1)} = 0.$$

It is moreover clear that the nilfactum is a combinant of the functions P, Q ; and the form of the equation is therefore

$$(a, \dots, a', \dots)^{mn(mn-1)}(\alpha, \dots)^{2kn(mn-1)}(\beta, \dots)^{2km(mn-1)} = 0.$$

Now the equation in question will be satisfied, 1°, if the curves $U = 0, V = 0$ touch each other; let the condition for this be $\nabla = 0$. 2°, if there exists a curve $\lambda P + \mu Q = 0$ passing through two of the intersections of the curves $U = 0, V = 0$; let the condition be $\Omega = 0$. There is reason to think that the equation contains the factor Ω^2 , and that the form thereof is $\Omega^2 \nabla = 0$.

Assuming that this is so, and observing that ∇ , the osculant or discriminant of the functions U, V , is of the form

$$\nabla = (\alpha, \dots)^{n(n+2m-3)}(\beta, \dots)^{m(m+2n-3)},$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} \Omega^2 &= \left(\left\| \begin{array}{c} \alpha, \beta, \dots \\ \alpha', \beta', \dots \end{array} \right\| \right)^{mn(mn-1)} \\ &\quad \times (\alpha, \dots)^{kn(n-1)(2m-1) + (k-1)n(n+2m-3)} \\ &\quad \times (\beta, \dots)^{km(m-1)(2n-1) + (k-1)m(m+2n-3)}, \end{aligned}$$

and consequently

$$\begin{aligned} \Omega &= \left(\left\| \begin{array}{c} \alpha, \beta, \dots \\ \alpha', \beta', \dots \end{array} \right\| \right)^{\frac{1}{2}mn(mn-1)} \\ &\quad \times (\alpha, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}n(n-1)k(2m-1) + \frac{1}{2}(k-1)n(n+2m-3)} \\ &\quad \times (\beta, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)k(2n-1) + \frac{1}{2}(k-1)m(m+2n-3)}, \end{aligned}$$

This is the solution of the proposed question. Suppose for instance $n = 1$, then

$$\Omega = \left(\left\| \begin{array}{c} \alpha, \beta, \dots \\ \alpha', \beta', \dots \end{array} \right\| \right)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)} (\alpha, \dots)^{(k-1)(m-1)} (\beta, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)k + \frac{1}{2}(k-1)(m-1)}.$$

If moreover $k = 1$, then

$$\Omega = \left(\left\| \begin{array}{c} \alpha, \beta, \dots \\ \alpha', \beta', \dots \end{array} \right\| \right)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)} (\beta, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)};$$

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this is right, for writing

$$P = ax + \beta y + \gamma z, \quad Q = a'x + \beta'y + \gamma'z, \quad V = bx + b'y + b''z,$$

then if two of the intersections of the curve $U = 0$ with the line $V = 0$ lie in a line with the point $P = 0, Q = 0$, then the point in question, that is the point

$$(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma, \gamma a' - \gamma'a, a\beta' - a'\beta),$$

must lie in the line $V = 0$; and the condition reduces itself to

$$(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma, \gamma a' - \gamma'a, a\beta' - a'\beta \ni b, b', b'')^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)} = 0,$$

where the index $\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)$ is accounted for as denoting the number of pairs of points out of the m intersections of the curve $U = 0$ with the line $V = 0$.

If in general $k = 1$, then writing as before

$$P = ax + \beta y + \gamma z, \quad Q = a'x + \beta'y + \gamma'z,$$

we have

$$\Omega = (\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}mn(mn-1)}(\alpha, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}n(n-1)(2m-1)}(\beta, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)(2n-1)},$$

where $\Omega = 0$ is the condition in order that the point $(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma, \dots)$ may lie with two of the intersections of the curves $U = 0, V = 0$. Or writing (X, Y, Z) for the coordinates of the given point, the condition is

$$\Omega = (\alpha, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}n(n-1)(2m-1)}(\beta, \dots)^{\frac{1}{2}m(m-1)(2n-1)}(X, Y, Z)^{mn(mn-1)} = 0.$$

I have found that if

$$U = (a, \dots \ni x, y, z)^m, \quad V = (b, \dots \ni x, y, z)^n,$$

$$W = (c, \dots \ni x, y, z)^p, \quad T = (d, \dots \ni x, y, z)^q,$$

the condition in order that the point (X, Y, Z) may lie in lined with one of the intersections of the curves $U = 0, V = 0$, and one of the intersections of the curves $W = 0, T = 0$, is

$$\Omega = (a, \dots)^{npq}(b, \dots)^{mpq}(c, \dots)^{mnq}(d, \dots)^{mnp}(X, Y, Z)^{mnpq} = 0.$$

Supposing that the curves $W = 0, T = 0$ become identical with the curves $U = 0, V = 0$ respectively, this becomes

$$\Omega = (a, \dots)^{n^2 \cdot 2m}(b, \dots)^{m^2 \cdot 2n}(X, Y, Z)^{mn \cdot mn} = 0,$$

and the variation from the correct form given above is what might have been expected.

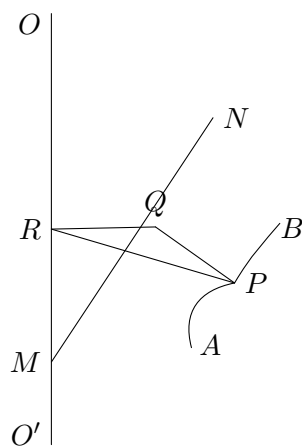
491. ON THE QUARTIC SURFACES $(\sqrt{U}, V, W)^2 = 0$.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 111–113.]

p. 25 [491]

The general Torus, or surface generated by the rotation of a conic about a fixed axis anywise situate, has been investigated by M. De La Gournerie, *Jour. de l'Ecole Polyt.*, t. XXIII. (1863), pp. 1–74. The surface is one of the fourth order, having a nodal circle; and with its equation of the form $F^2 - UW = 0$, consequently of the form in question. The leading points of the theory are as follows:

Consider (fig. 1) the plane of the conic in any particular position thereof; let this meet the axis of rotation OO' in the point M , and let the projection of OO' on the plane of the conic be MN . Take P any point of the conic; draw PQ in the plane of the conic, perpendicular to MN ,



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and QR perpendicular to OO' , and join PR : the point P of the conic describes a circle radius

$$RP = \sqrt{RQ^2 + QP^2}.$$

Hence if $\angle OMN = \alpha$, and if $MQ = x$, $QP = y$ are the coordinates in the plane of the conic of the point P ; and if the coordinates x, y, z are measured, z upwards from M in the direction MO , and x, y in the plane at right angles to the axis OO' : we have

$$z = x \cos \alpha, \quad \sqrt{x^2 + y^2} = \sqrt{x^2 \sin^2 \alpha + y^2};$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$x = z \sec \alpha, \quad y = \sqrt{x^2 + y^2 - z^2 \tan^2 \alpha}.$$

Hence the equation of the conic being $F(x, y) = 0$, that of the torus is

$$F(z \sec \alpha, \sqrt{x^2 + y^2 - z^2 \tan^2 \alpha}) = 0.$$

Thus taking the equation of the conic to be

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h \ni x, y, 1)^2 = 0;$$

or, as this may be written,

$$(ax^2 + 2gx + c + by^2)^2 = 4y^2(hx + f)^2,$$

we have at once the equation of the torus in the form

$$[az^2 \sec^2 \alpha + 2gz \sec \alpha + c + b(x^2 + y^2 - z^2 \tan^2 \alpha)]^2 = 4(x^2 + y^2 - z^2 \tan^2 \alpha)(hz \sec \alpha + f)^2,$$

which is of the form $F^2 - 4UW = 0$; or, as it is better to write it, $V^2 - 4UL^2 = 0$, where

$$V = az^2 \sec^2 \alpha + 2gz \sec \alpha + c + b(x^2 + y^2 - z^2 \tan^2 \alpha),$$

$$U = x^2 + y^2 - z^2 \tan^2 \alpha, \quad L = hz \sec \alpha + f, \quad W = L^2.$$

There is thus a nodal circle $V = 0, L = 0$, that is

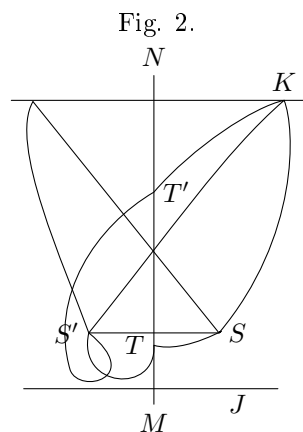
$$z = -\frac{f}{h} \cos \alpha,$$

$$bh^2(x^2 + y^2) - bf^2 \sin^2 \alpha + af^2 - 2gfh + ch^2 = 0.$$

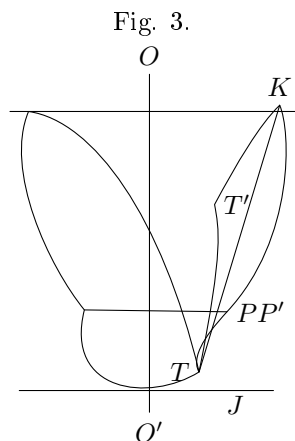
But the origin of this nodal circle is better seen geometrically. For observe that the radius of the circle described by the point P of the conic depends only on the square of the ordinate PQ : hence if we have on the conic two points S, S' situate symmetrically in regard to the line MN , these points S, S' will describe one and the same circle, which will be a nodal circle on the surface. And there is in fact one such pair of points S, S' ; for (see fig. 2) considering in the plane of the conic the equal conic situate symmetrically thereto on the other side of the line MN , the two conics intersect in two points T, T' (real or imaginary) on the line MN , and in two

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other points S, S' (real or imaginary) situate symmetrically in regard to MN ; we have thus the required pair of points which generate the nodal circle.



A meridian section of the torus (or section through the axis OO') is a quartic curve symmetrical in regard to this axis, and having two (real or imaginary) nodes the intersections of the plane by the nodal circle: see fig. 3, which shows the section for the surface generated by a conic such as in fig. 2. The quartic curve has 8 double tangents, 2 of them at right angles to the axis OO' , the remaining 6 forming 3 pairs



of tangents situate symmetrically in regard to this axis; so that attending only to one tangent of each pair, we may say that there are 3 oblique bitangents: one of these is the line TT' ; and the section of the torus by a plane through this line at right angles to the plane of the meridian section is in fact the two conics of fig. 2, either of which by its rotation about OO' generates the torus. But taking either of the other two oblique bitangents, the section by a plane through the bitangent at right angles to the meridian plane is in like manner a pair of conics situate symmetrically in regard to the bitangent, and such that either of them by its rotation

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about the axis OO' generates the torus. It thus appears that the same torus may be generated in three different ways by the rotation of a conic about the axis OO' .

In the particular case where the plane of the conic passes through the axis, the meridian section consists of two symmetrically situated conics, intersecting the axis in the points T, T' , which are nodes of the surface, the surface having as before a nodal circle generated by the rotation of the two symmetrically situated intersections S, S' of the two conics. The equation is included under the foregoing form, but it is at once obtained from that of the conic,

$$(ax^2 + 2gx + c + by^2)^2 = 4y^2(hx + f)^2,$$

by writing therein z for x and $\sqrt{x^2 + y^2}$ for y ; viz. the equation of the torus here is

$$\{az^2 + 2gz + c + b(x^2 + y^2)\}^2 = 4(x^2 + y^2)(hz + f)^2,$$

and the two nodes thus are

$$x = 0, \quad y = 0, \quad az^2 + 2gz + c = 0.$$

492. NOTE ON A SYSTEM OF ALGEBRAICAL EQUATIONS.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 132, 133.]

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Consider the system of equations

$$a + b(y + z)^2 + cy^2z^2 = 0,$$

$$a + b(z + x)^2 + cz^2x^2 = 0,$$

$$a + b(x + y)^2 + cx^2y^2 = 0,$$

which is a particular case of that belonging to the porism of the in-and-circumscribed triangle. We have y and z the roots of

$$a + bx^2 + 2u \cdot bx + u^2(b + cx^2) = 0;$$

consequently

$$y + z = \frac{-2bx}{b + cx^2},$$

$$yz = \frac{a + bx^2}{b + cx^2};$$

or substituting in the equation between y and z , this becomes

$$(ac + b^2)(a + 4bx^2 + cx^4) = 0,$$

so that if $ac + b^2$ is not $= 0$, we have

$$a + 4bx^2 + cx^4 = 0,$$

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and moreover

$$\begin{aligned}(x-y)(x-z) &= x^2 + \frac{2bx^2}{b+cx^2} + \frac{a+bx^2}{b+cx^2} \\ &= \frac{1}{b+cx^2}(a+4bx^2+cx^4) = 0,\end{aligned}$$

so that $x = y$ or else $x = z$. If $x = z$, the three equations reduce themselves to the two

$$\begin{aligned}a + bx^2 + 2y \cdot bx + y^2(b + cx^2) &= 0, \\ a + 4bx^2 + cx^4 &= 0,\end{aligned}$$

giving $y = x$, or else

$$y = -\frac{3bx + cx^3}{b + cx^2};$$

and it hence appears that if from this last equation and $a + 4bx^2 + cx^4 = 0$ we eliminate x , the result must be $a + 4by^2 + cy^4 = 0$. For in the same way that the elimination of y, z from the original three equations gives $a + 4bx^2 + cx^4 = 0$, the elimination of x, z from the same three equations will give $a + 4by^2 + cy^4 = 0$, so that in any case y is a root of this equation.

493. ON EVOLUTES AND PARALLEL CURVES.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 183–200.]

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In abstract geometry we have a conic called the Absolute; lines which are harmonics of each other in regard to the absolute, or, what is the same thing, which are such that each contains the pole of the other in regard to the absolute, are said to be at right angles. Similarly, points which are harmonics of each other in regard to the absolute, or, what is the same thing, which are such that each lies in the polar of the other, are said to be quadrantal.

A conic having double contact with the absolute is said to be a circle; the intersection of the two common tangents is the centre of the circle; the line joining the two points of contact, or chord of contact, is the axis of the circle.

Taking as a definition of equidistance that the points of a circle are equidistant from the centre, we arrive at the notion of distance generally, and we can thence pass down to that of equal circles; but the notion of equal circles may be established descriptively in a more simple manner:

Any two circles have an axis of symmetry, viz. this is the line joining their centres; and they have a centre of homology, viz. this is the intersection of their axes. They intersect in four points, lying in pairs on two lines through the centre of homology: they have also four tangents meeting in pairs in two points on the axis of symmetry. Now if the two lines through the centre of homology are harmonically related to the two axes, or, what is the same thing, if the two points on the axis of symmetry are harmonically related to the two centres, then the circles are equal.

Circles which are equal to the same circle are equal to each other, and the entire series of circles which are equal to a given circle, are said to be a system of circles of constant magnitude.

Starting from these general considerations, I pass to the question of evolutes and parallel curves: it will be understood that everything—lines at right angles, circles, poles, polars, reciprocal curves, &c.—refers to the absolute.

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At any point of a curve we have a normal, viz. this is a line at right angles to the tangent; or, what is the same thing, it is the line joining the point with the pole of the tangent. The locus of the pole of the tangent is the reciprocal curve, and for any point of a given curve, the pole of the tangent at that point is the corresponding point of the reciprocal curve. Hence, also the normal is the line from the point to the corresponding point of the reciprocal curve. And the curve and its reciprocal have at corresponding points the same normal.

The envelope of the normals is the evolute; any curve having with the given curve the same normals (and therefore the same evolute) is a parallel curve; in other words, the parallel curve is any orthogonal trajectory of the normals of the given curve.

The parallel curve is also the envelope of a circle of constant radius having its centre on the given curve; or, again, it is the envelope of a circle of constant radius touching the given curve.

The theory in the above form is directly applicable to spherical, or rather conical, geometry; but in ordinary plane geometry the absolute degenerates into a point-pair, the two circular points at infinity, or say the points I, J ; and this is a case that requires to be separately treated. The theory in the general case, the absolute a conic, is the more symmetrical and elegant, and it might appear advantageous to commence with this; but upon the whole I prefer the opposite course, and will commence with the case of plane geometry, the absolute a point-pair.

The subject connects itself with that of foci: I call to mind that a common tangent of the curve and the absolute is a focal tangent, and the intersection of two focal tangents a focus. In the case where the absolute is a point-pair, the focal tangents are the tangents from I to the curve, and the tangents from J to the curve, or say these are the I -tangents and the J -tangents; a focus is the intersection of an I -tangent and a J -tangent; the line IJ , when it touches the

curve, and (when the curve passes through I and J or either of them) the tangents at I or J to the curve are usually not reckoned as focal tangents; and other singular tangents, for instance a double or stationary tangent through I or J , are also excluded from the focal tangents; and the number of foci is of course reckoned accordingly, viz. it is the product of the number of the I -tangents into that of the J -tangents. So when the absolute is a conic; if this is touched by the curve, the common tangent at the point of contact is not reckoned as a focal tangent; and we may also exclude any singular tangents which touch the absolute; and the number of foci is reckoned accordingly, viz. it is equal to the number of pairs of focal tangents.

Let the Plückerian numbers for the given curve be $(m, n, \delta, \kappa, \tau, \iota)$, viz. m the order, n the class, δ the number of nodes, κ of cusps, τ of bitangents, ι of inflexions; and suppose moreover that D is the deficiency, and α the statitude; viz.

$$\begin{aligned}\alpha &= 3m + \iota, & &= 3n + \kappa; \\ 2D &= (m-1)(m-2) - 2\delta - 2\kappa \\ &= (n-1)(n-2) - 2\tau - 2\iota \\ &= -2m - 2n + 2 + \alpha \\ &= n - 2m + 2 + \kappa, & &= m - 2n + 2 + \iota.\end{aligned}$$

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And let the corresponding numbers for the evolute be

$$(m'', n'', \delta'', \kappa'', \tau'', \iota''; D'', \alpha'').$$

These are most readily obtained, as in Clebsch's paper, "Ueber die Singularitäten algebraischer Curven," *Crelle*, t. LXIV. (1864), pp. 98-100, viz. it being assumed that we have

$$n'' = m + n, \quad \iota'' = 0,$$

then by reason that the evolute has a (1,1) correspondence with the original curve, the two curves have the same deficiency, or writing this relation under the form

$$m'' - 2n'' + \iota'' = m - 2n + \iota,$$

we have $m'' = 3m + \iota = \alpha$; and the Plückerian relations then give the values of $\kappa'', \delta'', \tau''$.

In regard to these equations $n'' = m + n$, $\iota'' = 0$, I remark that if we have two curves of the orders m, m' , and on these points P, Q having an (a, a') correspondence, the line PQ envelopes a curve of the class $ma' + m'a$, and the number of inflexions is in general $= 0$. Now in the present case, taking P on the given curve and Q the point of intersection with IJ of the normal (or harmonic of the tangent), the orders of the curves are $(m, 1)$, and the correspondence is $(n, 1)$; whence as stated $n'' = m + n$, $\iota'' = 0$.

The formulae thus are

$$\begin{aligned} m'' &= \alpha, \\ n'' &= m + n, \\ \iota'' &= 0, \\ \kappa'' &= -3m - 3n + 3\alpha, \\ \alpha'' &= 3\alpha, \\ D'' &= D, \end{aligned}$$

in which formulae it is assumed that the curve has no special relations to the points I, J ; or, what is the same thing, that the line IJ intersects the curve in m points distinct from each other, and from the points I, J .

It is to be added (see Salmon's *Higher Plane Curves*, [Ed. 2], (1852), pp. 109 et seq.) that m of the κ'' cusps arise from the intersections of the curve with IJ , these cusps being situate on the line IJ , and each of them the harmonic of one of the intersections in question, and the cuspidal tangent being for each of them the line IJ . The intersections of the evolute by the line IJ are these m cusps each 3 times, and besides ι points arising from the ι inflexions of the curve; viz. at any inflexion the two consecutive normals intersect in a point on the line IJ , being in fact the harmonic of the intersection of IJ with the tangent at the inflexion. It was in this manner that Salmon obtained the number $3m + \iota$ of the points at infinity of the evolute, that is the expression $m'' = 3m + \iota (= \alpha)$ for the order of the evolute.

The remaining $-4m - 3n + 3\alpha$ cusps arise from the points on the curve where there is a circle of 4-pointic intersection, or contact of the third order, and in this

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manner the number of them was found, Salmon, [Ed. 2], p. 113, in the particular case of a curve without nodes or cusps, and generally in Zeuthen's *Nyt Bidrag* &c., p. 91; the number of the points in question, in the foregoing form $-4m - 3n + 3\alpha$, is also obtained in my Memoir, "On the curves which satisfy given conditions," *Phil. Trans.* (1868), pp. 75–143, see p. 97, [406].

It is further to be noticed that the $m + n$ tangents to the evolute from either of the points I, J are made up of the line IJ counting m times (in respect that it is a tangent at each of the above-mentioned m cusps) and of the n tangents from the points in question to the original curve. Or taking the two points I, J conjointly, say the $2m + 2n$ common tangents of the absolute and the evolute are made up of the line IJ (or axis of the absolute) counting m times, and of the $2n$ focal tangents of the original curve. The focal tangents of the original curve and of the evolute are thus the same $2n$ lines; and the two curves have the same foci.

The above are the ordinary values of $m'', n'', \iota'', \kappa''$, but if the given curve touch the line IJ , then the evolute has at the point of contact an inflexion, the stationary tangent being the line IJ ; and if the given curve pass through one or other of the points I, J , the evolute has in this case an inflexion on the tangent at the point in question, this tangent being the stationary tangent of the evolute: but observe that the inflexion is not at the point I or J in question: and for each inflexion there is a diminution = 1 in the class, 3 in the order, and 5 in the number of cusps. Suppose that the point I is a f_1 -tuple point on the given curve; then the evolute has f_1 inflexions; and similarly if the point J is a f_2 -tuple point on the given curve, then the evolute has f_2 inflexions. Hence writing $f_1 + f_2 = f$, we have thus f inflexions; and if moreover the number of contacts with the line IJ be g , then we have on this account g inflexions; or in all $f + g$ inflexions, and the formulae become

$$\begin{aligned} m'' &= \alpha - 3f - 3g, \\ n'' &= m + n - f - g, \\ \iota'' &= f + g, \\ \kappa'' &= -3m - 3n + 3\alpha - 5f - 5g. \end{aligned}$$

It is to be noticed here that the number of the intersections of the given curve with the line IJ (other than the points I, J and the points of contact) is $= m - f_1 - f_2 - 2g$, that is $m - f - 2g$: each of these gives as before a cusp on the evolute, the cuspidal tangent being IJ ; we have besides on the line IJ (in respect of the g contacts) g inflexions, the stationary tangent being the line IJ ; and each of the ι inflexions gives for the evolute a point on the line IJ ; hence the whole number of intersections with the line IJ is $3(m - f - 2g) + 3g + \iota, = 3m + \iota - 3f - 3g$, which is thus the order of the evolute.

The tangents from the point I or J to the evolute are the line IJ counting $m - f - 2g$ times in respect of the cusps on this line and $2g$ times in respect to the inflexions, that is $m - f$ times; the tangents at the point in question to the given curve each twice as touching the evolute at an inflexion, $2f_1$ or $2f_2$: and the remaining

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$n - 2f_1 - g$, or $n - 2f_2 - g$ tangents from the point in question to the given curve; the whole number is thus $(m - f) + 2f_1 + (n - 2f_1 - g)$ or $(m - f) + 2f_2 + (n - 2f_2 - g)$, $= m + n - f - g$, the class of the evolute. The two values of n'' give

$$2n'' = 2m + (n - 2f_1 - g) + (n - 2f_2 - g),$$

viz. twice the class of the evolute $=$ twice the order of the curve $+$ the number of the focal I -tangents $+$ that of the focal J -tangents; but this is not true for all relations whatever of the curve to the absolute.

The tangents from I to the given curve (excluding the line IJ and the tangents at I) are $n - 2f_1 - g$ tangents; and similarly the tangents from I to the evolute (excluding the line IJ and the stationary tangents through I) are the same $n - 2f_1 - g$ tangents; say the curve and the evolute have the same $n - 2f_1 - g$ I -tangents. Similarly they have the same $n - 2f_2 - g$ J -tangents; or together the same $2(n - f_1 - f_2 - g)$, $= 2(n - f - g)$ focal tangents. And the curve and evolute have the same $(n - 2f_1 - g)(n - 2f_2 - g)$ foci.

The foregoing specialities f and g refer, g to the ordinary contacts of the line IJ with the curve, viz. the curve is supposed to have with the curve at an ordinary or non-singular point thereof a contact or 2-pointic intersection, and f , that is f_1 or f_2 , to the multiple points having f_1 or f_2 ordinary branches, none of them touching the line IJ . Thus the formulae do not apply to the cases of IJ passing through a node or a cusp of the given curve, or touching it at an inflexion; nor to the cases where at I or J the curve touches IJ , or where there is at I or J an ordinary double point with one of its branches touching IJ , or where there is at I or J a cusp, where the cuspidal tangent is or is not IJ .

It is easy to see that in the case of a multiple point of any kind whether situate on IJ or at I or J , each branch of the curve produces its own separate effect on the singularities of the evolute: thus if we have on IJ a double point neither branch touching IJ , then the separate effect of each branch is nil, therefore the effect of the double point is also nil: but if one branch touch the line IJ , then the whole effect is the same as if we had this branch only; viz. we have here the case $g = 1$. And so if there is at I or J a double point with one branch touching the line IJ , then the effect of this branch is as if we had this branch only (a case not yet investigated) but the other branch is the case $f = 1$. And so if we have at I or J a double point with two ordinary branches touching each other (tacnode or, if the two branches have a contact higher than the first order, oscnode), then if the branches do not touch the line IJ the case is $f = 2$, but if they do, then the effect is twice that of an ordinary branch touching IJ . In support of these conclusions, observe that such multiple points, with ordinary branches, present themselves in the case of two or more curves which intersect or touch each other in any manner; and that the evolute of a system of two or more curves is simply the system of the evolutes of the several curves.

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It follows as regards the relations of the given curve to the points I, J , and the effect thereby produced on the evolute, we only need to consider the case of a single branch; viz. the cases are

the given curve intersects the line IJ at a point other than I or J , and
belonging thereto there is a branch ordinary or singular,

not touching IJ ,
touching IJ ;

and the given curve passes through the point I or J , and belonging thereto
there is a branch ordinary or singular,

not touching IJ ,
touching IJ .

I have succeeded in determining the effect, not for a singular branch of any kind whatever, but for branches of the form $y = x^k$, $y^{k-1} = x^k$; viz. $k = 2$, each of these is an ordinary branch, $k = 3$, the first $y = x^3$ is an inflexional branch and the second $y^2 = x^3$ a cuspidal branch; and so $k > 3$ the two branches are respectively inflexional and cuspidal of a higher order. I do this very simply by consideration of the curve $x^{k-1}z = y^k$.

The curve in question $x^{k-1}z = y^k$, is a unicursal curve, and it has a reciprocal of the same form $X^{k-1}Z = Y^k$, hence

$$m = n = k; \quad 0 = n - 2m + 2 + \kappa,$$

whence

$$\iota = \kappa = k - 2, \quad \tau = \delta = \frac{1}{2}(k - 2)(k - 3);$$

viz. the point $x = 0, y = 0$ is a cusp equivalent to $k - 2$ cusps and $\frac{1}{2}(k - 2)(k - 3)$ nodes; and the point $z = 0, y = 0$ is an inflexion equivalent to $k - 2$ inflexions and $\frac{1}{2}(k - 2)(k - 3)$ bitangents.

The equation $U = x^{k-1}z - y^k = 0$ of the curve is satisfied by writing therein

$$x : y : z = 1 : \theta : \theta^k;$$

and these values give

$$d_x U : d_y U : d_z U = (k - 1)x^{k-2}z : -ky^{k-1} : x^{k-1} = (k - 1)\theta^k : -k\theta^{k-1} : 1.$$

Taking the coordinates of I, J to be (α, β, γ) and $(\alpha', \beta', \gamma')$ respectively, and X, Y, Z as current coordinates, the equation of the normal at the point (x, y, z) of the curve $U = 0$ is readily found to be

$$\begin{aligned} & (\alpha' d_x U + \beta' d_y U + \gamma' d_z U) \begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z \\ \alpha & \beta & \gamma \\ x & y & z \end{vmatrix} \\ & + (\alpha d_x U + \beta d_y U + \gamma d_z U) \begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z \\ \alpha' & \beta' & \gamma' \\ x & y & z \end{vmatrix} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

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Hence for the curve in question the equation of the normal is

$$\begin{aligned} & \{(k - 1)\alpha'\theta^k - k\beta'\theta^{k-1} + \gamma'\}\{(\beta X - \alpha Y)\theta^k + (\alpha Z - \gamma X)\theta + (\gamma Y - \beta Z)\} \\ & + \{(k - 1)\alpha\theta^k - k\beta\theta^{k-1} + \gamma\}\{(\beta' X - \alpha' Y)\theta^k + (\alpha' Z - \gamma' X)\theta + (\gamma' Y - \beta' Z)\} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

or, expanding and reducing, this equation is

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \theta^{2k} \cdot (k-1) \{ (\alpha\beta' + \alpha'\beta)X - 2\alpha\alpha'Y \} \\
 & + \theta^{2k-1} \cdot -k \{ 2\beta\beta'X - (\alpha\beta' + \alpha'\beta)Y \} \\
 & + \theta^{k+1} \cdot (k-1) \{ 2\alpha\alpha'Z - (\alpha\gamma' + \alpha'\gamma)X \} \\
 & + \theta^k \cdot \{ (k+1)(\beta\gamma' + \beta'\gamma)X + (k-2)(\gamma\alpha' + \gamma'\alpha)Y \\
 & \quad - (2k-1)(\alpha\beta' + \alpha'\beta)Z \} \\
 & + \theta^{k-1} \cdot -k \{ (\beta\gamma' + \beta'\gamma)Y - 2\beta\beta'Z \} \\
 & + \theta \cdot \{ (\gamma\alpha' + \gamma'\alpha)Z - 2\gamma\gamma'X \} \\
 & + \{ 2\gamma\gamma'Y - (\beta\gamma' + \beta'\gamma)Z \} = 0,
 \end{aligned}$$

where k is a positive integer not less than 2; hence except in the case $k = 2$, all the terms $\theta^{2k}, \theta^{2k-1}, \dots, \theta, \theta^0$ have different indices, and the coefficients $k-1, k$, &c. none of them vanish; if however $k = 2$, then the terms $\theta^{2k-1}, \theta^{k+1}$ coalesce into a single term, as do also the terms θ^{k-1} and θ ; moreover the coefficient $k-2$ is $= 0$.

The evolute is the envelope of the line represented by the foregoing equation, considering therein θ as an arbitrary parameter; viz. the equation is obtained by equating to zero the discriminant of the foregoing equation in θ . Hence in general the class of the evolute is $= 2k$, and its order is $= 2(2k-1)$; results which agree with the formulae for n'', m'' , since in the present case

$$m + n = k + k = 2k, \quad \alpha = 3n + \kappa = 3k + (k-2) = 4k-2.$$

And moreover there are not any inflexions, $\iota'' = 0$ as before.

The equation may however contain a factor in θ independent of (X, Y, Z) , and throwing out this factor, say its order is $= s$, the expression for the class is $2k - s, = m + n - s$, and that for the order is $4k - 2 - 2s, = \alpha - 2s$. Moreover, in the original equation or in the equation thus reduced, it may happen that the equation will on writing therein $\Omega = 0$ (Ω a linear function of X, Y, Z) acquire a factor of the order ω , independent of (X, Y, Z) ; the line $\Omega = 0$ is in this case a stationary tangent, $= \omega - 1$ inflexions; and the discriminant contains the factor $\Omega^{\omega-1}$, which may be thrown out; that is we have here

$$n'' = 2k - s, \quad \iota'' = \omega - 1, \quad m'' = 4k - 2 - 2s - (\omega - 1);$$

agreeing with the relation

$$m'' - 2n'' + 2 + \iota'' = 0$$

which holds good in virtue of the evolute being a unicursal curve. It is in this manner that the values of m'', n'', ι'' are obtained in the several cases to be considered, viz.:

- A_k Inflexion situate on IJ , which is not a tangent.
- B_k Inflexion situate on IJ , which is a tangent.
- C_k Cusp situate on IJ , which is not a tangent.
- D_k Cusp situate on IJ , which is a tangent.
- P_k Inflexion at J , IJ not a tangent.
- Q_k Inflexion at J , IJ a tangent.
- R_k Cusp at J , IJ not a tangent.
- S_k Cusp at J , IJ a tangent.

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The results are respectively as follows:

	A_k	B_k	C_k	D_k	P_k	Q_k	R_k	S_k	
$m'' = \alpha$	—	0	$3k-3$	$k-2$	$k+1$	k	$3k-2$	$2k-2$	$2k$
$n'' = m+n$	—	0	$k-1$	0	1	1	k	$k-1$	k
$\iota'' = 0$	+	0	$k-1$	$k-2$	$k-1$	$k-2$	$k-2$	0	0
$\kappa'' = -3m-3n+3\alpha$	—	0	$5k-5$	$2k-4$	$2k+1$	$2k-1$	$5k-4$	$3k-3$	$3k$

	A_2C_2	B_2D_2	A_3	B_3	C_3	D_3	P_2R_2	Q_2S_2	P_3	Q_3	R_3	S_3	
$m'' = \alpha$	—	0	3	0	6	0	4	3	4	3	7	4	6
$n'' = m+n$	—	0	1	0	2	0	1	1	2	1	3	2	3
$\iota'' = 0$	+	0	1	0	2	0	2	1	0	1	1	0	0
$\kappa'' = -3m-3n+3\alpha$	—	0	5	0	10	0	7	5	6	5	11	6	9

read for instance in B_k ,

$$m'' = \alpha - (3k-3), \quad n'' = m+n - (k-1), \quad \iota'' = 0 + (k-1),$$

and

$$\kappa'' = -3m-3n+3\alpha - (5k-5);$$

and so in other cases.

A_2C_2 (that is indifferently A_2 or C_2) is when there is on IJ an ordinary point, IJ not a tangent; and so B_2D_2 when there is on IJ an ordinary point, IJ a tangent. Similarly P_2R_2 when there is at J an ordinary point, IJ not a tangent; only instead thereof I have written P_2R_2 to indicate that (for a reason which will appear) the numbers are not deducible from those for P_2 or R_2 by writing therein $k=2$; and Q_2S_2 is when there is at J an ordinary point, IJ a tangent.

Case A_k . We have to take the line IJ passing through the inflexion; the condition for this is $\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma = 0$: there is no speciality, or we have

$$n'' = 2k, \quad m'' = 4k-2, \quad \iota'' = 0;$$

whence also $\kappa'' = 0$; the value of κ'' being in every case deduced from those of m'', n'', ι'' by the formula

$$3m'' + \iota'' = 3n'' + \kappa''.$$

Case B_k . I write $\gamma = \gamma' = 0$, the equation of the normal is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{2k} \cdot (k-1) \{ (\alpha\beta' + \alpha'\beta)X - 2\alpha\alpha'Y \} \\ & + \theta^{2k-1} \cdot -k \{ 2\beta\beta'X - (\alpha\beta' + \alpha'\beta)Y \} \\ & + \theta^{k+1} \cdot (k-1)2\alpha\alpha'Z \\ & + \theta^k \cdot -(2k-1)(\alpha\beta' + \alpha'\beta)Z \\ & + \theta^{k-1} \cdot k \cdot 2\beta\beta'Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

or, after throwing out the factor θ^{k-1} , in the form

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{k+1}(X, Y) \\ & + \theta^k(X, Y) \\ & + \theta^2Z \\ & + \theta Z \\ & + Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

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Writing $Z = 0$, we have a factor θ^k , whence $\iota'' = k - 1$, and then $n'' = k + 1$, $m'' = 2k - (k - 1) = k + 1$, agreeing with the table. The process holds good for $k = 2$.

Case C_k . I write $\beta = \beta' = 0$; this brings as well the inflexion as the cusp upon the line IJ ; but it has been seen (Case A_k) that there is not any reduction on account of this position of the inflexion, hence the whole effect will be due to the cusp. The equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{2k} \cdot (k - 1) \{-2\alpha\alpha'Y\} \\ & + \theta^{k+1} \cdot (k - 1) \{2\alpha\alpha'Z - (\alpha\gamma' + \alpha'\gamma)X\} \\ & + \theta^k \cdot (k - 2)(\gamma\alpha' + \gamma'\alpha)Y \\ & + \theta \cdot \{(\gamma\alpha' + \gamma'\alpha)Z - 2\gamma\gamma'X\} \\ & + 2\gamma\gamma'Y = 0, \\ & \theta^{2k}Y \\ & + \theta^{k+1}(Z, X) \\ & + \theta^k(k - 2)Y \\ & + \theta(Z, X) \\ & + Y = 0, \end{aligned}$$

so that here $n'' = 2k$. On writing $Y = 0$, there is a factor $(1 - \frac{\theta}{\infty})^{k-1}$ thrown out (indicated by the reduction of the order from $2k$ to $k + 1$), whence

$$\iota'' = k - 2, \quad m'' = 2(2k - 1) - (k - 2) = 3k.$$

The process holds good for $k = 2$.

Case D_k . We may write $\alpha = \alpha' = 0$; the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{2k-1} \cdot -k \cdot 2\beta\beta'X \\ & + \theta^k \cdot (k + 1)(\beta\gamma' + \beta'\gamma)X \\ & + \theta^{k-1} \cdot -k \{(\beta\gamma' + \beta'\gamma)Y - 2\beta\beta'Z\} \\ & + \theta \cdot -2\gamma\gamma'X \\ & + 2\gamma\gamma'Y - (\beta\gamma' + \beta'\gamma)Z = 0, \\ & \theta^{2k-1}X \\ & + \theta^kX \\ & + \theta^{k-1}(Y, Z) \\ & + \theta X \\ & + (Y, Z) = 0, \end{aligned}$$

so that $n'' = 2k - 1$. Writing $X = 0$, we have the factor $(1 - \frac{\theta}{\infty})^k$ (indicated by the reduction of order from $2k - 1$ to $k - 1$), whence $\iota'' = k - 1$, and then

$$m'' = (4k - 2) - 2 - (k - 1) = 3k - 3,$$

agreeing with the table. The process holds good for $k = 2$.

Case P_k . We have $\beta' = \gamma' = 0$; the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{2k} \cdot (k - 1) \{\alpha'\beta X - 2\alpha\alpha'Y\} \\ & + \theta^{2k-1} \cdot -k \{-\alpha'\beta Y\} \\ & + \theta^{k+1} \cdot (k - 1) \{-\alpha'\gamma X\} \\ & + \theta^k \cdot (k - 2) \gamma\alpha'Y - (2k - 1)\alpha'\beta Z \\ & + \theta \cdot \gamma\alpha'Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

$$\begin{aligned}
 &\theta^{2k-1}(X, Y) \\
 &+ \theta^{2k-2}Y \\
 &+ \theta^k X \\
 &+ \theta^{k-1}(k-2)Y + Z \\
 &+ Z = 0,
 \end{aligned}$$

so that here $n'' = 2k - 1$. Writing $Z = 0$, we have the factor θ^{k-1} , whence $\iota'' = k - 2$,

$$m'' = 4k - 4 - (k - 2) = 3k - 2,$$

agreeing with the table. If, however, $k = 2$, then on writing $Z = 0$ the equation (instead of the factor θ^{k-1}) acquires the factor $\theta^k (= \theta^2)$; so that here $n'' = 3$, $\iota'' = 1$, $m'' = 3$, agreeing with the column P_2R_2 of the table.

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Case Q_k . We have $\gamma = 0$, $\beta' = \gamma' = 0$, viz. $\beta' = 0$ in the formulae of B_k . The equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{2k} \cdot (k-1)\alpha'\beta Y \\ & + \theta^{2k-1} \cdot -k(-\alpha'\beta Y) \\ & + \theta^{k+1} \cdot (k-1)2\alpha\alpha'Z \\ & + \theta^k \cdot -(2k-1)\alpha'\beta Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^k X \\ & + \theta^{k-1} Y \\ & + \theta Z \\ & + Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

so that $n'' = k$. For $Z = 0$ there is the factor θ^{k-1} , hence

$$\iota'' = k-2, \quad m'' = 2(k-1) - (k-2) = k.$$

The process holds good for $k = 2$.

Case R_k . We have $\beta = 0$, $\alpha' = 0$, $\beta' = 0$, viz. $\alpha' = 0$ in the formulae of C_k . The equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{k+1} \cdot (k-1)(-\alpha\gamma'X) \\ & + \theta^k \cdot (k-2)(\alpha\gamma'Y) \\ & + \theta \cdot (\alpha\gamma'Z - 2\gamma\gamma'X) \\ & + 2\gamma\gamma'Y = 0, \end{aligned}$$

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^{k+1} X \\ & + \theta^k Y(k-2) \\ & + \theta(Z, X) \\ & + Y = 0, \end{aligned}$$

so that $n'' = k+1$, $\iota'' = 0$, $m'' = 2k$. But observe that in the particular case $k = 2$, the form is

$$\theta^3 X + \theta(Z, X) + Y = 0,$$

the term $\theta^k Y$ disappearing on account of the factor $k-2$. Here on writing $X = 0$, there is a factor $(1 - \frac{\theta}{\infty})^2$ (indicated by the reduction of order from 3 to 1), hence $\iota'' = 1$, $n'' = 3$, $m'' = 2 \cdot 2 - 1 = 3$, agreeing with the column $P_2 R_2$.

Case S_k . We have $\alpha = 0$, $\alpha' = \beta' = 0$, viz. $\beta' = 0$ in the formulae of D_k . The equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^k \cdot (k+1)\beta\gamma'X \\ & + \theta^{k-1} \cdot -k\beta\gamma'Y \\ & + \theta \cdot -2\gamma\gamma'X \\ & + 2\gamma\gamma'Y - \beta\gamma'Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

$$\begin{aligned} & \theta^k X \\ & + \theta^{k-1} Y \\ & + \theta X \\ & + Y + Z = 0, \end{aligned}$$

so that $n'' = k$, $\iota'' = 0$, $m'' = 2k - 2$. The process applies to the case $k = 2$.

As to the formula for $A_3, B_3, \dots, S_3$, there is nothing special in these; they are simply deduced from those for $A_k, B_k, \dots, S_k$ by writing therein $k = 3$. And we have thus the foregoing series of formulae, which will apply to the greater part of the cases which ordinarily arise. For instance suppose there is at I or J a triple point = cusp + 2 nodes; there is here an ordinary branch and a cuspidal (ordinary cuspidal) branch and according as IJ touches neither branch, the ordinary branch, or the cuspidal branch, the corrections to $m'', n'', \iota'', \kappa''$ are

$$R_2 + R_3, \quad S_2 + R_3, \quad R_2 + S_3$$

respectively. Observe moreover that A_2C_2 is no speciality, B_2D_2 is the speciality $g = 1$, P_2R_2 the speciality $f = 1$.

There is a remarkable case in which the fundamental assumption of the $(1, 1)$ correspondence of the evolute with the original curve ceases to be correct. In fact,

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in the case about to be considered of a parallel curve; the parallel to any given curve is *in general* a curve not breaking up into two distinct curves of the same order with such given curve, and when this is so (viz. when the parallel curve does not break up) each normal of the parallel curve is a normal at two distinct points thereof: the evolute of the parallel curve is thus the evolute of the given curve taken twice; and the parallel curve and its evolute have not a (1, 1) but (1, 2) correspondence. Hence, ($m, n, \delta, \kappa, \tau, \iota$) the unaccented letters referring to the parallel curve, or say rather to a curve which has a (1, 2) correspondence with its evolute, and, as before, the twice accented letters to the evolute, it is *not true* that

$$m'' - 2n'' + \iota'' = m - 2n + \iota;$$

it will subsequently appear that the values of m'', n'' are correct, those of ι'', κ'' suffering a modification; viz. the formulae are

$$\begin{aligned} m'' &= \alpha - 3f - 3g, \\ n'' &= m + n - f - g, \\ \iota'' &= f + g - \Theta, \\ \kappa'' &= -3m - 3n + 3\alpha - 5f - 5g - \Theta, \end{aligned}$$

where, for the present, I leave Θ undetermined.

Coming now to the parallel curve, let the numbers in regard to it be $m', n', \delta', \kappa', \tau', \iota'; \alpha', D'$. Supposing in the first instance that the given curve does not stand in any special relation to I, J , the formulae are

$$\begin{aligned} m' &= 2m + 2n, & \alpha' &= 6n + 2\alpha, \\ n' &= 2n, & 2D' &= -4m + 2 + 2\alpha, = -2m + 2n + \alpha, \\ \iota' &= 2\alpha - 6m, \\ \kappa' &= 2\alpha. \end{aligned}$$

Considering the parallel curve as the envelope of a circle of constant radius having its centre on the given curve, it appears (e.g. by consideration of the case of the ellipse) that when the radius of the circle is $= 0$, there is not any depression in the order of the parallel curve, but that the parallel curve reduces itself to the given curve twice, together with the system of tangents from the points I, J to the given curve: the order of the parallel curve is thus $m' = 2m + 2n$.

To find the class, consider the tangents from a given point to the parallel curve; about the point as centre describe a circle, radius k ; then the tangents in question are respectively parallel to, and correspond each to each with, the common tangents of the circle and the given curve, and the number of these is $= 2n$, that is $n' = 2n$.

Each inflexion of the given curve gives rise to two inflexions of the parallel curve; and the inflexions of the parallel curve arise in this way only: that is $\iota' = 2\iota, = 2\alpha - 6m$. And the Plückerian relations then give $\kappa' = 2\alpha$; a value which may be investigated independently.

Attending now to the singularities f and g ; the values of n', ι' are unaltered: to obtain m' we as before consider the particular case where the radius of the variable

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circle is $= 0$: the parallel curve here breaks up into the original curve, together with the focal tangents from the points I, J ; viz. we have

$$m' = 2n + (n - 2f_1 - g) + (n - 2f_2 - g), \quad = 2m + 2n - 2f - 2g;$$

and knowing m', n', ι' we have κ' .

The points on IJ of the original curve are I, J counting as f_1 and f_2 respectively; or together as f points: the points of contact counting as $2g$: and besides $m - f - 2g$ points. As regards the parallel curve, we have the same points on IJ ; but here I is $(n - g)$ tuple point, having in

respect of each branch of the f_1 -tuple point on the original curve a pair of branches touching each other, and in respect of each of the tangents from I to the given curve a single branch, together $2f_1 + (n - 2f_1 - g) = n - g$ branches; and thus counting $n - g$ times: similarly J counts $n - g$ times. Hence also for the parallel curve $f'_1 = f'_2 = n - g$. In respect of each of the points g , we have a point where there are two branches touching each other and the line IJ ; and thus counting 4 times, or together as $4g$: moreover, on account of the two branches at each of these points, $g' = 2g$. Lastly, each of the $m - f - 2g$ points is a node on the parallel curve; and as such counts twice; $m' = 2(n - g) + 4g + 2(m - f - 2g) = 2m + 2n - 2f - 2g$ as above.

And we have thus the formulae

$$\begin{aligned} m' &= 2m + 2n - 2f - 2g, \\ n' &= 2n, \\ \iota' &= -6m + 2\alpha, \quad = 2\iota, \\ \kappa' &= 2\alpha - 6f - 6g, \quad = 6n + 2\kappa - 6f - 6g, \\ f' &= 2n - 2g, \\ g' &= 2g, \end{aligned}$$

where observe that m' is $= 2n''$; that is, twice the class of the evolute (which relation however is not in all cases true for a curve with singularities); and further that $n' - f' - g'$ is $= 0$.

The case of a curve for which $n - f - g = 0$ is very interesting and remarkable. Recurring to the formulae for the evolute, we have here $m'' = \kappa$, $n'' = m$, $\iota'' = n$, $\kappa'' = n - 3m + 3\kappa$. And for the parallel curve $m' = 2m$, $n' = 2n$, $\iota' = 2\iota$, $\kappa' = 2\kappa$, $f' = 2f$, $g' = 2g$; formulae which lead to the assumption that the parallel curve here breaks up into two distinct curves, each such as the given curve.

Observe further that for a curve possessing the singularities f and g , but where $n - f - g$ is not $= 0$; then for the parallel curve we have as above $n' - f' - g' = 0$; or the parallel of the parallel curve should, according to the assumption, break up into two distinct curves such as the parallel curve; this is of course correct.

Consider the evolute of the parallel curve: since for the parallel curve $n' - f' - g' = 0$, the formulae for the evolute thereof (viz. those containing the undetermined quantity Θ)

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are $m''' = \kappa'$, $n''' = m'$, $\iota''' = \iota' - \Theta$, $\kappa''' = n' - 3m' + 3\kappa' - \Theta$, or substituting for m', n', κ' their values, and comparing with the formulae in regard to the evolute, we have

$$\begin{aligned} m''' &= 2\alpha - 6f - 6g, & &= 2m'', \\ n''' &= 2m + 2n - 2f - 2g, & &= 2n'', \\ \iota''' &= 2n - \Theta, & &= 2\iota'' + 2(n - f - g) - \Theta, \\ \kappa''' &= -6m - 4n + 6\alpha - 12f - 12g - \Theta, & &= 2\kappa'' + 2(n - f - g) - \Theta, \end{aligned}$$

where $m'', n'', \iota'', \kappa''$ refer to the evolute. Hence by assuming $\Theta = 2(n - f - g)$, the values of $m''', n''', \iota''', \kappa'''$ become $2m'', 2n'', 2\iota'', 2\kappa''$, viz. the evolute of the parallel curve is the evolute of the original curve taken twice. Observe that in the foregoing value of Θ , the letters n, f, g refer not to the parallel curve, the evolute whereof is under consideration, but to the curve from which such parallel curve was derived; this value $\Theta = 2(n - f - g)$ is not a value of Θ applicable to be substituted in the evolute-formulae for the case of a curve which has with its evolute a (1, 2) correspondence.

Instead of the foregoing case of the f , viz. f - and g -singularities, we may, as regards the parallel curve, consider the original curve as having any I - and J -singularities whatever. Suppose in this case (excluding always the line IJ and the tangents at I or J) the number of tangents from I to the curve is $n - I$, and the number of tangents from J to the curve is $n - J$, then when the radius of the variable curve is $= 0$, the parallel curve becomes the original curve twice together with the $(n - I) + (n - J) = 2n - I - J$ tangents; so that the order is $m' = 2m + 2n - I - J$; we have, as before, $n' = 2n$ and $\iota' = 2\iota$, and these values give κ' , so that the equations are

$$\begin{aligned} m' &= 2m + 2n - I - J, \\ n' &= 2n, \\ \iota' &= -6m + 2\alpha, & &= 2\iota, \\ \kappa' &= 2\alpha - I - J, & &= 6n + 2\kappa - 3I - 3J. \end{aligned}$$

Suppose $2n - I - J = 0$; this implies $n - I = 0$, $n - J = 0$ since neither $n - I$ nor $n - J$ can be negative; viz. that there are no I - or J -tangents; and conversely, when this is the case $2n - I - J = 0$: and we have then $m', n', \iota', \kappa' = 2m, 2n, 2\iota, 2\kappa$; viz. it is assumed, as before, that the parallel curve breaks up into two distinct curves such as the original curve; that is, the condition in order that the parallel curve should break up, is that the original curve has no focal tangents. Observe that the number of foci is $= (n - I)(n - J)$ which is $= 0$ if only $n - I = 0$ or $n - J = 0$; but as regards real curves $I = J$, so that the equations $n - I = 0$ and $n - J = 0$ are one and the same equation, satisfied if $(n - I)(n - J) = 0$; so that for a real curve without foci (real or imaginary) the parallel curve will break up. An instance given to me by Dr Salmon is the curve $x^{\frac{2}{3}} + y^{\frac{2}{3}} - c^{\frac{2}{3}} = 0$ or $(x^2 + y^2 - c^2)^3 + 27c^2x^2y^2 = 0$, here $m = 6$, $n = 4$,

¹That the order of the evolute is not (in every case of a curve with singularities) one-half this, or $= m + n - \frac{1}{2}(I + J)$, is at once seen by remarking that there is no reason why $I + J$ should be even.

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$\delta = 4$, $\kappa = 6$, $\iota = 0$, $\tau = 3$; the points I, J are each of them a cusp, the tangents being the line IJ ; the number of tangents from a cusp is $n - 3$, $= 1$, but for the cusp I or J , this tangent is the line IJ itself, so that we have $I = J = 4$.

Theory when the Absolute is a conic.

When the Absolute is a conic the formulae for the evolute are essentially the same as those in the former case, but the formulae for the parallel curve are modified essentially and in a very remarkable manner. I observe that corresponding to a passage of the given curve through I or J we have a contact with the Absolute, so that in the present case f will properly denote the number of contacts of the given curve with the Absolute, and attending to this singularity only, viz. considering a given curve $(m, n, \delta, \kappa, \iota, \tau; \alpha, D)$ having f contacts with the Absolute, the formulae for the evolute are

$$\begin{aligned} m'' &= \alpha - 3f, \\ n'' &= m + n - f, \\ \iota'' &= f, \\ \kappa'' &= -3m - 3n + 3\alpha - 5f. \end{aligned}$$

In the case $f = 0$, these at once follow from the two equations $n'' = m + n$, and $\iota'' = 0$. The normal is the line joining a point of the given curve with the pole of the tangent; or, what is the same thing, it is the line joining the point of the given curve with the corresponding point of the reciprocal curve: the degrees of the two curves are m, n , and the correspondence is a $(1, 1)$ correspondence. Hence, by the general theorem previously referred to, it follows that we have $n'' = m + n$, and $\iota'' = 0$. Compare herewith the demonstration of the theorem in the case where the Absolute is a point-pair.

The formulae for the parallel curve are

$$\begin{aligned} m' &= 2m + 2n - 2f, \\ n' &= 2m + 2n - 2f, \\ \iota' &= 2\alpha - 6f, \\ \kappa' &= 2\alpha - 6f, \\ f' &= 2m + 2n - 2f, \end{aligned}$$

(so that $m' = n'$, $\iota' = \kappa'$). The intersections of the curve and Absolute are in this case the points f each twice, and besides $2m - 2f$ points; similarly the common tangents are the tangents at f each twice and besides $2n - 2f$ tangents. Now I remark that the parallel curve, when the radius of the variable circle is $= 0$, reduces itself to the original curve twice, together with the $2n - 2f$ common tangents, and the $2m - 2f$ common points; the order is thus $= 2m + (2n - 2f)$, and the class $= 2n + (2m - 2f)$: and these are the values in the general case where the radius of the variable circle is not $= 0$.

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But in the remarkable case where the curve and its evolute have a $(1, 2)$ correspondence, then I correct the formulae by adding $-\Theta$ to the expressions for ι', κ' respectively. We have for the evolute of the parallel curve

$$\begin{aligned} m''' &= 2m'', \\ n''' &= 2n'', \\ \iota''' &= 2\iota'' + (2m + 2n - 4f) - \Theta, \\ \kappa''' &= 2\kappa'' + (2m + 2n - 4f) - \Theta, \end{aligned}$$

viz. assuming $\Theta = 2m + 2n - 4f$, this means that the evolute is the evolute of the original curve taken twice.

A very interesting case is when $m = n = f$: observe that neither $m - f$ nor $n - f$ can be negative, so that the assumed relation $m + n - 2f = 0$ would imply these two relations. We have here for the parallel curve $m' = 2m$, $n' = 2n$, $\iota' = 2\iota$, $\kappa' = 2\kappa$; the parallel curve in fact breaking up into two curves such as the given curve. And in this case the formulae for the evolute assume the very simple form $m'' = \kappa$, $n'' = f$, $\iota'' = f$, $\kappa'' = -2f + 3\kappa$.

Whatever the original curve may be, we have for the parallel curve $m' = n' = f'$, so that the formulae for the evolute of the parallel curve are of the foregoing form $m''' = \kappa'$, $n''' = f'$, $\iota''' = f' - \Theta$, $\kappa''' = -2f' + 3\kappa' - \Theta$, which agree with the above values of $m''', n''', \iota''', \kappa'''$. In the particular case $m = n = f$, we have $\Theta = 0$, so that the evolute-formulae, if originally written down without the terms in Θ , would still be $m''' = 2m''$, $n''' = 2n''$, $\iota''' = 2\iota''$, $\kappa''' = 2\kappa''$; viz. the evolute is here the original evolute taken twice; as already seen, the parallel curve consisted of two curves such as the original curve, and each of these has for its evolute the evolute of the original curve.

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494.

EXAMPLE OF A SPECIAL DISCRIMINANT.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 211–213.]

If we have a function $(a, \dots)(x, y, z)^n$, where the coefficients $(a, \dots)$ are such that the curve $(a, \dots)(x, y, z)^n = 0$ has a node, and *a fortiori* if this curve has any number of nodes or cusps, the discriminant of the function (that is, the discriminant of the general function $(*, \dots)(x, y, z)^n$, substituting in such discriminant for the coefficients their values for the particular function in question) vanishes *identically*. But the particular function has nevertheless a *special discriminant*, viz. this is a function of the coefficients which, equated to zero, gives the condition that the curve may have (besides the nodes or cusps which it originally possesses) one more node; and the determination of this special discriminant (which, observe, is not deducible from the expression of the discriminant of the general function $(*, \dots)(x, y, z)^n$) is an interesting problem. I have, elsewhere, shown that if the curve in question $(a, \dots)(x, y, z)^n = 0$ has δ nodes and κ cusps, then the degree of the special discriminant in regard to the coefficients a , &c., of the function is $= 3(n-1)^2 - 7\delta - 11\kappa$: and I propose to verify this in the case of a quartic curve with two cusps.

Consider the curve

$$6nx^2y^2 + 12rxyz^2 + (4gx + 4iy + cz)z^3 = 0,$$

where $x = 0$ is the tangent at a cusp; $y = 0$ the tangent at a cusp; and $z = 0$ the line joining the two cusps.

For the special discriminant we have

$$\begin{aligned} 3nxy^2 + 3ryz^2 + gz^3 &= 0, \\ 3nx^2y + 3rxz^2 + iz^3 &= 0, \\ z\{6rxy + (3gx + 3iy + 4cz)z\} &= 0; \end{aligned}$$

the last of which may be replaced by the equation of the curve.

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Assume $x = \lambda z$, $y = \mu z$, the first two equations give

$$\begin{aligned} 3(n\lambda\mu + r)\mu + g &= 0, \\ 3(n\lambda\mu + r)\lambda + i &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

whence also

$$6n\lambda^2\mu^2 + 6r\lambda\mu + g\lambda + i\mu = 0,$$

and the equation of the curve gives

$$6n\lambda^2\mu^2 + 12r\lambda\mu + 4g\lambda + 4i\mu + c = 0,$$

whence eliminating $g\lambda + i\mu$ we find

$$18n\lambda^2\mu^2 + 12r\lambda\mu - c = 0.$$

Moreover the first two equations give

$$9(n\lambda\mu - r)^2\lambda\mu - ig = 0,$$

or putting $\lambda\mu = \theta$ we have

$$\begin{aligned} 18n\theta^2 + 12r\theta - c &= 0, \\ 9(n\theta + r)^2\theta - ig &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

from which θ is to be eliminated.

The equations are

$$\begin{aligned} 18n\theta^2 + 12r\theta - c &= 0, \\ 9n^2\theta^3 + 18nr\theta^2 + 9r^2\theta - ig &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} 18n^2\theta^3 + 36nr\theta^2 + 18r^2\theta - 2ig &= 0, \\ 18n^2\theta^3 + 12nr\theta^2 - cn\theta &= 0, \\ 24nr\theta^2 + (18r^2 + cn)\theta - 2ig &= 0, \\ 18nr\theta^2 + 12r^2\theta - cr &= 0, \\ (6r^2 + 3cn)\theta - 6ig + 4cr &= 0, \\ \theta = \frac{6ig - 4cr}{6r^2 + 3cn} = \frac{2}{3} \frac{3ig - 2cr}{2r^2 + cn}; \end{aligned}$$

or substituting in $18n\theta^2 + 12r\theta - c = 0$, this is

$$8n(3ig - 2cr)^2 + 8r(3ig - 2cr)(2r^2 + cn) - c(2r^2 + cn)^2 = 0.$$

Hence, developing, the special discriminant is

$$\begin{aligned} \square = & -c^3n^2 + 12c^2nr^2 - 72cginr - 36cr^4 \\ & + 72g^2i^2n + 48gir^3, \end{aligned}$$

which is as it should be of the degree 5, = 3.3² - 11.2.

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495.

ON THE ENVELOPE OF A CERTAIN QUADRIC SURFACE.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 244–246.]

To find the envelope of the quadric surface

$$ax^2 + by^2 + cz^2 + dw^2 = 0,$$

where the coefficients vary subject to the conditions

$$\begin{cases} a\alpha^2 + b\beta^2 + c\gamma^2 + d\delta^2 = 0, \\ \frac{p^2}{a} + \frac{q^2}{b} + \frac{r^2}{c} + \frac{s^2}{d} = 0, \end{cases}$$

$(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$ and (p, q, r, s) being respectively constant.

We have in the usual manner

$$\begin{aligned} x^2 + \lambda\alpha^2 + \mu\frac{p^2}{a^2} &= 0, \\ y^2 + \lambda\beta^2 + \mu\frac{q^2}{b^2} &= 0, \\ z^2 + \lambda\gamma^2 + \mu\frac{r^2}{c^2} &= 0, \\ w^2 + \lambda\delta^2 + \mu\frac{s^2}{d^2} &= 0. \end{aligned}$$

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and thence

$$a^2 = \frac{-\mu p^2}{x^2 + \lambda \alpha^2}, \quad \&c.,$$

and substituting these values μ disappears and we have

$$\begin{aligned} p\sqrt{x^2 + \lambda \alpha^2} + q\sqrt{y^2 + \lambda \beta^2} + r\sqrt{z^2 + \lambda \gamma^2} + s\sqrt{w^2 + \lambda \delta^2} &= 0, \\ \frac{\alpha^2 p}{\sqrt{x^2 + \lambda \alpha^2}} + \frac{\beta^2 q}{\sqrt{y^2 + \lambda \beta^2}} + \frac{\gamma^2 r}{\sqrt{z^2 + \lambda \gamma^2}} + \frac{\delta^2 s}{\sqrt{w^2 + \lambda \delta^2}} &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

from which λ is to be eliminated; the second equation is here the derived function of the first in regard to λ , so that rationalising the first equation, the result is, as will be shown, of the form $(*)(\lambda, 1)^4 = 0$, and the result is obtained by equating to zero the discriminant of the quartic function.

Denoting for shortness the first equation by

$$A + B + C + D = 0,$$

the rationalised form is

$$\begin{aligned} (A^4 + B^4 + C^4 + D^4 - 2A^2B^2 - 2A^2C^2 - 2A^2D^2 \\ - 2B^2C^2 - 2B^2D^2 - 2C^2D^2)^2 - 64A^2B^2C^2D^2 = 0, \end{aligned}$$

which is of the form

$$-(\mathfrak{A} + 2\mathfrak{B}\lambda + \mathfrak{C}\lambda^2)^2 + (a, b, c, d, e)(1, \lambda)^4 = 0,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} \mathfrak{A} &= p^4 x^4 \dots - 2p^2 q^2 x^2 y^2 \dots, \\ \mathfrak{B} &= p^4 \alpha^2 x^2 \dots - p^2 q^2 (\alpha^2 y^2 + \beta^2 x^2) \dots, \\ \mathfrak{C} &= p^4 \alpha^4 \dots - 2p^2 q^2 \alpha^2 \beta^2 \dots, \\ a &= 8x^2 y^2 z^2 w^2, \\ 4b &= 8\alpha^2 y^2 z^2 w^2 + \dots, \\ 6c &= 8\alpha^2 \beta^2 z^2 w^2 + \dots, \\ 4d &= 8\alpha^2 \beta^2 \gamma^2 w^2 + \dots, \\ e &= 8\alpha^2 \beta^2 \gamma^2 \delta^2. \end{aligned}$$

Writing I', J' for the two invariants we find without difficulty

$$I' = I - \frac{4}{3}P + \Delta^2, \quad J' = J - Q + \frac{1}{3}\Delta P - \frac{8}{27}\Delta^3,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} I &= ae - 4bd + 3c^2, \\ J &= ace - ad^2 - b^2e - c^3 + 2bcd, \\ \Delta &= \mathfrak{A}\mathfrak{C} - \mathfrak{B}^2, \\ P &= a\mathfrak{C}^2 - 4b\mathfrak{B}\mathfrak{C} + 2c(\mathfrak{A}\mathfrak{C} + 2\mathfrak{B}^2) - 4d\mathfrak{A}\mathfrak{B} + e\mathfrak{A}^2, \\ Q &= (ce - d^2)\mathfrak{A}^2 + (ae + 2bd - 3c^2)\frac{1}{3}(\mathfrak{A}\mathfrak{C} + 2\mathfrak{B}^2) + (ac - b^2)\mathfrak{C}^2 \\ &\quad - 2(ad - bc)\mathfrak{B}\mathfrak{C} - 2(be - cd)\mathfrak{A}\mathfrak{B}. \end{aligned}$$

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The result thus is

$$\left(I - P + \frac{4}{3}\Delta^2\right)^3 - 27\left(J - Q + \frac{1}{3}\Delta P - \frac{8}{27}\Delta^3\right)^2 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing, it is

$$\begin{aligned} & (I - P)^3 - 27(J - Q)^2 - 9\Delta P(J - 2Q) \\ & + \Delta^2(4I^2 - 8IP + P^2) \\ & + 8\Delta^3(J - 2Q) \\ & + \Delta^4 \cdot \frac{16}{3}I = 0, \end{aligned}$$

where the left-hand side is of the order 24 in (x, y, z, w) . I apprehend that the order should be = 12 only; for writing (x, y, z, w) in place of (x^2, y^2, z^2, w^2) , the equations which connect (a, b, c, d) express that these quantities are the coordinates of a point on a plane cubic; and the problem is in fact that of finding the reciprocal of the plane cubic: this is a sextic cone, or restoring (x^2, y^2, z^2, w^2) instead of (x, y, z, w) , we should have a surface of the order 12. I cannot explain how the reduction is effected.

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TABLES OF THE BINARY CUBIC FORMS FOR THE NEGATIVE
DETERMINANTS, $= 0 \pmod{4}$, FROM -4 TO -400 ; AND $= 1$
 $\pmod{4}$, FROM -3 TO -99 ; AND FOR FIVE IRREGULAR
NEGATIVE DETERMINANTS.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 246–261.]

The theory of binary cubic forms for determinants, as well positive as negative, has been studied by M. Arndt in the memoir “Versuch einer Theorie der homogenen Functionen des dritten Grades mit zwei Variabeln,” *Grunert's Archiv*, t. XVII. (1851, pp. 1–54); and in the later memoir, “Tabellarische Berechnung der reducirten binären cubischen Formen und Klassification derselben für alle negativen Determinanten ($-D$) von $D = 3$ bis $D = 2000$,” ditto, t. XXXI. (1858), pp. 335–445, he has given a very valuable Table of the forms for a Negative Determinant. It has appeared to me suitable to arrange this Table in the manner made use of for Quadratic Forms in my memoir “Tables des formes quadratiques binaires pour les déterminants négatifs $D = -1$ jusqu'à $D = -100$, pour les déterminants positifs non carrés depuis $D = 2$ jusqu'à $D = 99$, et pour les treize déterminants négatifs du premier millier,” *Crelle*, t. LX. (1862), pp. 357–372, [335]; and confining myself to the limits of the last-mentioned tables I deduce from that of M. Arndt the three Tables which follow.

To explain the arrangement, I give in the first instance the following extract from M. Arndt's Table:

D .	<i>Reducirte Formen mit Charakteristik.</i>	<i>Klassen.</i>
3	$(0, 1, 1, 0)$ $(1, 0, -1, -1)$ $(1, 1, 0, -1)$ $(2, 1, 2)$ $(2, 1, 2)$ $(2, 1, 2)$	$\{ (0, 1, 1, 0), (1, 0, -1, \pm 1)$
4	$(0, 1, 0, -1)$ $(1, 0, -1, 0)$ $(2, 0, 2)$ $(2, 0, 2)$	$\{ (0, -1, 0, 1)$

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<i>D.</i>	<i>Reducirte Formen mit Charakteristik.</i>	<i>Klassen.</i>
7	$(0, 1, 1, -1)$ $(2, 1, 4)$	$\{ (0, -1, -1, 1)$
8	$(0, 1, 0, -2)$ $(2, 0, 4)$	$\{ (0, -1, 0, 2)$
11	$(0, 1, 1, -2)$ $(2, 1, 6)$	$\{ (0, -1, -1, 2)$
12	$(0, 1, 0, -3)$ $(2, 0, 6)$	$\{ (0, -1, 0, 3)$
15	$(0, 1, 1, -3)$ $(2, 1, 8)$	$\{ (0, -1, -1, 3)$
44	$(0, 1, 0, -11)(1, -1, -2, 0)$ $(2, 0, 22) \quad (6, 2, 8)$	$\{ (0, -1, 0, 11), (0, -2, \pm 1, 1)$
112	$(0, 1, 0, -28)(0, 2, 2, -2)(1, 2, 0, -4)$ $(2, 0, 56) \quad (8, 4, 16) \quad (8, 4, 16)$ $(1, -1, -3, -1)$ $(8, 4, 16)$	$\left\{ \begin{array}{l} (0, -1, 0, 28), (0, 2, 2, -2), \\ (1, \pm 1, -3, \pm 1) \end{array} \right.$
144	$(0, 1, 0, -36)(0, 2, 2, -3)$ $(2, 0, 72) \quad (8, 4, 20)$	$\{ (0, -1, 0, 36), (0, -2, -2, 3)$
156	$(0, 1, 0, -39)(1, -1, -3, 1)$ $(2, 0, 78) \quad (8, 2, 20)$	$\{ (0, -1, 0, 39), (1, \mp 1, -3, \pm 1)$
216	$(0, 1, 0, -54)(1, -2, -3, 0)(2, 0, -3, 0)$ $(2, 0, 108) \quad (14, 6, 18) \quad (12, 0, 18)$	$\left\{ \begin{array}{l} (0, -1, 0, 54), (0, \mp 3, 0, \pm 2), \\ (0, \mp 3, 2, \pm 1) \end{array} \right.$

The first column contains the value of the determinant, the second column contains the reduced forms, omitting the contrary and opposite forms; viz. for the cubic form (a, b, c, d) , the contrary form (equal, that is, properly equivalent to the given form) is $(-a, -b, -c, -d)$; and the opposite form (improperly equivalent to the given form) is $(a, -b, c, -d)$ or $(-a, b, -c, d)$; this second column contains also the characteristic of each cubic form, viz. the cubic form (a, b, c, d) has for its characteristic the quadratic form

$$\{2(b^2 - ac), bc - ad, 2(c^2 - bd)\},$$

(so that the cubic form and its characteristic have the same determinant

$$-D = (bc - ad)^2 - 4(b^2 - ac)(c^2 - bd), \quad \equiv 1 \text{ or } 0 \pmod{4},$$

and a cubic form which corresponds to a reduced characteristic is itself a reduced form. The third column contains for each determinant the entire series of unequal cubic forms (that is of the forms whereof no two are properly equivalent to each other), the representatives of the classes for this determinant. M. Arndt has included in his table the non-primitive classes (for example Det. = -112, the form $(0, 2, 2, -2)$), for which the terms (a, b, c, d) have a common divisor μ , but as these are at once

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deducible from the classes which belong to the determinant $= -\frac{D}{\mu^4}$, it seems better to omit the non-primitive classes.

The two opposite forms included in a single expression by means of the sign $\pm$ have opposite characteristics which are for the most part unequal to each other, for instance

$$\begin{array}{ll} \text{Det. } -44; & (0, -2, 1, 1) \text{ has the characteristic } (6, -2, 8), \\ & (0, 2, 1, -1) \hspace{10em} (6, 2, 8), \end{array}$$

where $(6, -2, 8)$, $(6, 2, 8)$ are unequal forms, but this is not always the case, for instance

$$\begin{array}{ll} \text{Det. } -112; & (1, -1, -3, -1) \text{ has the characteristic } (8, -4, 16), \\ & (1, 1, -3, 1) \hspace{10em} (8, 4, 16), \end{array}$$

where $(8, -4, 16) = (8, 4, 16)$, since each is an ambiguous form. Instead of the two unequal forms $(1, -1, -3, -1)$, $(1, 1, -3, 1)$ which correspond to the opposite (though equal) characteristics $(8, -4, 16)$, $(8, 4, 16)$, M. Arndt might have given the two forms $(1, 2, 0, -4)$ and $(1, -1, -3, -1)$ corresponding to the same characteristic $(8, 4, 16)$; but then it would not have appeared at a glance that the two classes were opposite to each other; and I presume that it is for this reason that he has selected the two representative forms $(1, -1, -3, -1)$ and $(1, 1, -3, 1)$. It must not, however, be imagined that the opposite cubic forms which correspond to opposite characteristics, which are ambiguous (and therefore equal to each other), are always, as in the last preceding example, unequal: for example Det. -144 , there is only the form $(0, -2, -2, 3)$ given as corresponding to the ambiguous characteristic $(8, 4, 20)$; the opposite form $(0, 2, -2, -3)$ corresponding to the opposite but equal characteristic $(8, -4, 20)$ is equal to $(0, -2, -2, 3)$, and so does not give rise to a distinct opposite class. In the new tables, the sign $\pm$ is only employed in regard to opposite ambiguous characteristics; for instance, Det. -4×28 there are given (not included in a single expression by means of the sign $\pm$) the two forms $(1, -1, -3, 1)$, $(1, 1, -3, 1)$ corresponding to the characteristic $2(2, \pm 1, 4)$.

I remark that, in a few instances M. Arndt, in passing from the second to the third column, has modified the expression for a cubic form in such manner that the characteristic has ceased to be a reduced form; for instance, Det. -216 , he has given in the third column the two forms $(0, \mp 3, 2, \pm 1)$ belonging to the characteristic $(18, \mp 6, 14)$; it would have been better, it appears to me, to preserve the expression of the second column $(1, -2, -3, 0)$, and adopt the two representative forms $(1, \mp 2, -3, 0)$; I have accordingly made this change.

I divide M. Arndt's table into two tables; the first of them corresponding to the determinants $\equiv 0 \pmod{4}$, the second to the determinants $\equiv 1 \pmod{4}$. In the first table I take for the characteristic the form

$$\{b^2 - ac, \frac{1}{2}(bc - ad), bd - c^2\},$$

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which belongs to the determinant $-\frac{1}{4}D$, and I arrange the cubic classes according to their order; viz. we have the properly primitive order (pp) when the terms $(a, 3b, 3c, d)$ have no common divisor; and the improperly primitive order (ip) when the terms $(a, 3b, 3c, d)$ have no common divisor other than 3, or what is the same thing when a and d being each of them divisible by 3, the terms (a, b, c, d) have no common divisor. But, moreover, the characteristic $\{b^2 - ac, \frac{1}{2}(bc - ad), bd - c^2\}$, may be of the properly primitive order pp ; or of the improperly primitive order ip ; or it may be of a derived order $\mu(A', B', C')$, $= \mu.pp$ or $\mu.ip$, according as (A', B', C') considered as a form belonging to the determinant

$$B'^2 - A'C' = -\frac{1}{4\mu^2}D,$$

is of the properly primitive or the improperly primitive order. And in these different cases, the cubic class is said to be of the order pp on pp , pp on ip , pp on $\mu.pp$, pp on $\mu.ip$, ip on pp , &c., as the case may be.

For the determinants $\equiv 1 \pmod{4}$, I retain the characteristic

$$\{2(b^2 - ac), bc - ad, 2(c^2 - bd)\},$$

and this being so, the division into orders is the same as in the former case; only as the characteristic, when primitive, is of necessity improperly primitive, the orders pp on pp and ip on pp no longer exist.

To every characteristic I annex in the tables the symbol of its composition; viz. 1 denotes the principal form, c a form which by its duplication, d a form which by its triplication, &c., produces the principal form, σ denotes the most simple form of order ip , σc , σd , &c., the forms obtained by combining σ with the forms c, d , &c., of the order pp . Similarly to a characteristic $\mu(A', B', C')$ I annex the symbol of composition of the form (A', B', C') , (considered as belonging to the determinant $B'^2 - A'C' = -\frac{D}{4\mu^2}$) multiplying this symbol by the number μ ; for instance, $\mu.1$ denotes that (A', B', C') is the principal form, and similarly in other cases.

I have given a third table for the determinants

$$-4 \times 243, \quad -4 \times 307, \quad -4 \times 339, \quad -4 \times 459, \quad -4 \times 675,$$

where $-243, -307, -339, -459, -675$ are those of the thirteen irregular negative determinants in the first thousand for which the number of classes is divisible by 3. The number $-4 \times 675, = -2700$, is beyond the limits of M. Arndt's Table, but the calculation (at least for the order pp on pp) presents no difficulty.

I remark that, according to M. Arndt (*Grunert*, t. XVII. p. 19), the number of cubic forms corresponding to a given characteristic (A, B, C) is equal to the number of proper transformations of $(A, -B, C)$, Det. D , into $(\frac{1}{2}A^2, B^2 - \frac{1}{2}AC, \frac{1}{2}C^2)$, Det. DB^2 , so that when there is no such transformation, there exists no cubic form corresponding to the characteristic (A, B, C) . This includes, I believe, the theorem in a letter of mine to M. Hermite, *Quarterly Mathematical Journal*, t. I. (1857), p. 85, [162], viz. that

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for a pp form (A, B, C) of negative determinant, there is either no corresponding cubic form, or else a single corresponding cubic form, according as (A, B, C) does not, or does, produce by its triplication the principal form; but the particular theorem, in the cases to which it applies, is the more convenient one: it shows at once that for a regular negative determinant the number of cubic forms corresponding to a properly primitive characteristic (or, what is the same thing, number of cubic classes of the order $(pp$ or $ip)$ on pp) is 1 or 3, according as the number of quadratic classes is not, or is, divisible by 3.

The inspection of the tables gives rise to other remarks, but at present I abstain from pursuing the subject further; I will only notice that in some instances, for example Det. -224 , the classes which correspond to characteristics of the principal genus are partly of the order pp on pp and partly of the order ip on pp .

Table I. of the binary cubic forms, the determinants of which are the negative numbers $\equiv 0 \pmod{4}$ from -4 to -400 .

Det.	Classes	Order	Charact.	Compn.
$4 \times$		on		
1	$0, -1, 0, 1$	pp	$1, 0, 1$	1
2	$0, -1, 0, 2$	pp	$1, 0, 2$	1
3	$0, -1, 0, 3$	ip	$1, 0, 3$	1
4	$0, -1, 0, 4$	pp	$1, 0, 4$	1
	$1, -1, -1, 1$	pp	$3pp$	$2(1, 0, 1)$
5	$0, -1, 0, 5$	pp	$1, 0, 5$	1
6	$0, -1, 0, 6$	ip	$1, 0, 6$	1
7	$0, -1, 0, 7$	pp	$1, 0, 7$	1
	$1, 0, -2, 2$			
	$1, 0, -2, -2$	pp	$2ip$	$2(2, \pm 1, 4)$
8	$0, -1, 0, 8$	pp	$1, 0, 8$	1
	$0, -2, 0, 1$	pp	$2pp$	$2(1, 0, 2)$
9	$0, -1, 0, 9$	ip	$1, 0, 9$	1
10	$0, -1, 0, 10$	pp	$1, 0, 10$	1
11	$0, -1, 0, 11$		$1, 0, 11$	1
	$0, -2, -1, 1$		$3, 1, 4$	d
	$0, -2, 1, 1$	pp	pp	$3, -1, 4$
12	$0, -1, 0, 12$	ip	$1, 0, 12$	1
13	$0, -1, 0, 13$	pp	$1, 0, 13$	1
14	$0, -1, 0, 14$	pp	$1, 0, 14$	1

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Det.	Classes	Order on		Charact.	Compn.
4×					
15	0, -1, 0, 15 1, -2, 0, 2 1, 2, 0, -2	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 15	1
16	0, -1, 0, 16	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 16	1
17	0, -1, 0, 17	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 17	1
18	0, -1, 0, 18 1, 1, -2, -2 1, -1, -2, 2	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 18	1
19	0, -1, 0, 19 0, 2, 1, -2 0, -2, 1, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>3pp</i>	3(1, 0, 2) 1, 0, 19 4, 1, 5	3.1 1 <i>d</i>
20	0, -1, 0, 20 0, -2, -2, 1	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 20	1
21	0, -1, 0, 21	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 21	1
22	0, -1, 0, 22	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 22	1
23	0, -1, 0, 23 1, -1, -2, 4 1, 1, -2, -4	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 23 3, -1, 8 3, 1, 8	1 <i>d</i> ² <i>d</i>
24	0, -1, 0, 24 0, -2, 0, 3	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 24	1
25	0, -1, 0, 25 1, -2, -1, 2 1, 2, -1, -2	<i>ip</i>	<i>2pp</i>	2(2, 0, 3)	2 <i>c</i>
26	0, -1, 0, 26 1, 0, -3, 2 1, 0, -3, -2	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 25 5(1, 0, 1) 1, 0, 26 3, -1, 9 3, 1, 9	1 5.1 1 <i>g</i> ² <i>g</i> ⁴
27	0, -1, 0, 27 0, -2, 1, 3 0, 2, 1, -3 0, -3, 0, 1	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 27 4, -1, 7 4, 1, 7 3(1, 0, 3)	1 <i>d</i> ² <i>d</i> 3.1
28	0, -1, 0, 28 1, 1, -3, 1 1, -1, -3, -1	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 28	1
		<i>pp</i>	<i>2ip</i>	2(2, ±1, 4)	2 <i>σ</i>

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Det.	Classes	Order	Charact.	Compn.
$4 \times$		on		
29	0, -1, 0, 29		1, 0, 29	1
	2, 1, -2, -2	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	5, 1, 6	g^2
	2, -1, -2, 2		5, -1, 6	g^4
30	0, -1, 0, 30	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 30	1
31	0, -1, 0, 31		1, 0, 31	1
	2, 1, -2, -3	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	5, 2, 7	d
	2, -1, -2, 3		5, -2, 7	d^2
32	0, -1, 0, 32	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 32	1
33	0, -1, 0, 33	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 33	1
34	0, -1, 0, 34	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 34	1
35	0, -1, 0, 35		1, 0, 35	1
	0, 2, 1, -4	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	4, 1, 9	g^2
	0, -2, 1, 4		4, -1, 9	g^4
36	0, -1, 0, 36	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 36	1
	0, -2, -2, 3	<i>ip</i> $2pp$	$2(2, 1, 5)$	$2c$
37	0, -1, 0, 37	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 37	1
38	0, -1, 0, 38		1, 0, 38	1
	2, -2, -1, 3	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	6, 2, 7	g^2
	2, 2, -1, -3		6, -2, 7	g^4
39	0, -1, 0, 39	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 39	1
	1, 1, -3, -1	<i>pp</i> <i>ip</i>	4, -1, 10	σe
	1, -1, -3, 1		4, 1, 10	σe^3
40	0, -1, 0, 40	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 40	1
	0, -2, 0, 5	<i>pp</i> $2pp$	$2(2, 0, 5)$	2.1
41	0, -1, 0, 41	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 41	1
42	0, -1, 0, 42	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 42	1
43	0, -1, 0, 43		1, 0, 43	1
	0, -2, 1, 5	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	4, -1, 11	d^2
	0, 2, 1, -5		4, 1, 11	d
44	0, -1, 0, 44	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	1, 0, 44	1
	1, 2, -1, -4	<i>pp</i> $2ip$	$2(2, \pm 1, 6)$	2σ
	1, -2, -1, 4			

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Det.	Classes	Order on		Charact.	Compn.
4×					
45	0, -1, 0, 45	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 45	1
	2, 0, -3, 3	<i>pp</i>	<i>3pp</i>	3(2, ±1, 3)	3 <i>c</i>
	2, 0, -3, -3				
46	0, -1, 0, 46	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 46	1
47	0, -1, 0, 47	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 47	1
	1, -2, -2, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	6, 1, 8	σf
	1, 2, -2, -2			6, -1, 8	σf^4
48	0, -1, 0, 48	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 48	1
	1, -1, -3, 3	<i>pp</i>	<i>4pp</i>	4(1, 0, 3)	4.1
	1, 1, -3, -3				
49	0, -1, 0, 49	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 49	1
50	0, -1, 0, 50			1, 0, 50	1
	2, 0, -3, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	6, -2, 9	g^4
	2, 0, -3, -2			6, 2, 9	g^2
51	0, -1, 0, 51			1, 0, 51	1
	0, -2, 1, 6	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	4, -1, 13	g^4
	0, 2, 1, -6			4, 1, 13	g^2
52	0, -1, 0, 52	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 52	1
	0, -2, -2, 5	<i>pp</i>	<i>2pp</i>	2(2, 1, 7)	2 <i>c</i>
53	0, -1, 0, 53			1, 0, 53	1
	1, -3, 0, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	6, -1, 9	g^2
	1, 3, 0, -2			6, 1, 9	g^4
54	0, -1, 0, 54	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 54	1
	1, 2, -3, 0	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	7, -3, 9	g^4
	1, -2, -3, 0	<i>pp</i>		7, 3, 9	g^2
	0, -3, 0, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>3pp</i>	3(2, 0, 3)	3 <i>c</i>
	0, 3, 0, -2				
55	0, -1, 0, 55	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 55	1
	1, -1, -3, 5	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 14	σe^3
	1, 1, -3, -5			4, 1, 14	σe
56	0, -1, 0, 56	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 56	1
	0, -2, 0, 7	<i>pp</i>	<i>2pp</i>	2(2, 0, 7)	2 <i>e</i> ²
57	0, -1, 0, 57	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 57	1
58	0, -1, 0, 58	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 58	1

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Det.	Classes	Order on		Charact.	Compn.
$4 \times$					
59	0, -1, 0, 59			1, 0, 59	1
	0, -2, 1, 7	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	4, -1, 15	j^6
	0, 2, 1, -7			4, 1, 15	j^3
60	0, -1, 0, 60	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 60	1
	1, 0, -4, 4	<i>pp</i>	$2ip$	$2(2, \pm 1, 8)$	2σ
	1, 0, -4, -4				
61	0, -1, 0, 61			1, 0, 61	1
	1, -2, -1, 6	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	5, -2, 13	g^2
	1, 2, -1, -6			5, 2, 13	g^4
62	0, -1, 0, 62	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 62	1
63	0, -1, 0, 63	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 63	1
	1, 0, -4, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 16	σe
	1, 0, -4, -2			4, 1, 16	σe^3
64	0, -1, 0, 64	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 64	1
	1, 0, -4, 0	<i>pp</i>	$4pp$	$4(1, 0, 4)$	4.1
65	0, -1, 0, 65	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 65	1
66	0, -1, 0, 66	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 66	1
67	0, -1, 0, 67			1, 0, 67	1
	0, -2, 1, 8	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	4, -1, 17	d^2
	0, 2, 1, -8			4, 1, 17	d
68	0, -1, 0, 68	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 68	1
	0, -2, -2, 7	<i>pp</i>	$2pp$	$2(2, 1, 9)$	$2e^2$
69	0, -1, 0, 69	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 69	1
70	0, -1, 0, 70	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 70	1
71	0, -1, 0, 71	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 71	1
	1, -3, 1, 3	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	8, -3, 10	σh^3
	1, 3, 1, -3			8, 3, 10	σh^4
72	0, -1, 0, 72	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 72	1
	0, -2, 0, 9	<i>ip</i>	$2pp$	$2(2, 0, 9)$	$2c$
	1, -2, -2, 4	<i>pp</i>	$6pp$	$6(1, 0, 2)$	6.1
	1, 2, -2, -4				
	2, -3, 0, 3	<i>pp</i>	$3pp$	$3(3, \pm 1, 3)$	$3c$
	2, 3, 0, -3				
73	0, -1, 0, 73	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 73	1

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Det.	Classes	Order		Charact.	Compn.
$4 \times$		on			
74	0, -1, 0, 74	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 74	1
75	0, -1, 0, 75			1, 0, 75	1
	0, -2, 1, 9	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	4, -1, 19	g^2
	0, 2, 1, -9			4, 1, 19	g^4
76	0, -1, 0, 76			1, 0, 76	1
	0, -4, 1, 1	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	5, -2, 16	g^2
	0, 4, 1, -1			5, 2, 16	g^4
77	0, -1, 0, 77	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 77	1
78	0, -1, 0, 78	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 78	1
79	0, -1, 0, 79	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 79	1
	2, -2, -2, 3	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	8, -1, 10	σf
	2, 2, -2, -3			8, 1, 10	σf^4
80	0, -1, 0, 80	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 80	1
81	0, -1, 0, 81	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 81	1
	0, -3, 2, 2	<i>ip</i>		9, -3, 10	g^2
	0, 3, 2, -2	<i>ip</i>		9, 3, 10	g^4
82	0, -1, 0, 82	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 82	1
83	0, -1, 0, 83			1, 0, 83	1
	0, -2, 1, 10	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	4, -1, 21	j^6
	0, 2, 1, -10			4, 1, 21	j^3
84	0, -1, 0, 84	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 84	1
	0, -2, -2, 9	<i>ip</i>	$2pp$	2(2, 1, 11)	2σ
85	0, -1, 0, 85	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 85	1
86	0, -1, 0, 86	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 86	1
87	0, -1, 0, 87	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 87	1
	1, -2, -3, 2	<i>pp</i>		7, -2, 13	g^4
	1, 2, -3, -2	<i>pp</i>		7, 2, 13	g^2
88	0, -1, 0, 88	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 88	1
	0, -2, 0, 11	<i>pp</i>	$2pp$	2(2, 0, 11)	2σ
89	0, -1, 0, 89			1, 0, 89	1
	1, -1, -4, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>pp</i>	5, -1, 18	m^8
	1, 1, -4, -2			5, 1, 18	m^4
90	0, -1, 0, 90	<i>ip</i>	<i>pp</i>	1, 0, 90	1

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Det. 4×	Classes	Order on		Charact.	Compn.
91	0, -1, 0, 91			1, 0, 91	1
	0, -2, 1, 11	pp	pp	4, -1, 23	g^4
	0, 2, 1, -11			4, 1, 23	g^2
92	0, -1, 0, 92			1, 0, 92	1
	2, -3, 0, 4	pp	pp	9, -4, 12	g^4
	2, 3, 0, -4			9, 4, 12	g^2
93	0, -1, 0, 93	ip	pp	1, 0, 93	1
94	0, -1, 0, 94	ip	pp	1, 0, 94	1
95	0, -1, 0, 95	pp	pp	1, 0, 95	1
	1, -2, -2, 6	pp	ip	6, -1, 16	σi^7
	1, 2, -2, -6			6, 1, 16	σi
96	0, -1, 0, 96	ip	pp	1, 0, 96	1
97	0, -1, 0, 97	pp	pp	1, 0, 97	1
98	0, -1, 0, 98	pp	pp	1, 0, 98	1
99	0, -1, 0, 99			1, 0, 99	1
	0, -2, 1, 12	ip	pp	4, -1, 25	g^2
	0, 2, 1, -12			4, 1, 25	g^4
100	0, -1, 0, 100	pp	pp	1, 0, 100	1
	0, -2, -2, 11	pp	2pp	2(2, 1, 13)	2.1
	1, -1, -4, 4	pp	5pp	5(1, 0, 4)	5.1
	1, 1, -4, -4				
	1, -3, -1, 3	pp	10pp	10(1, 0, 1)	10.1
	1, 3, -1, -3				

Table II. of the binary cubic forms the determinants of which are the positive numbers $\equiv 1 \pmod{4}$, from -3 to -99.

Det. 4×	Classes	Order on		Charact.	Compn.
3	0, 1, 1, 0	ip	ip	2, ± 1 , 2	σ
	1, 0, -1, 1	pp			
	1, 0, -1, -1	pp			
7	0, -1, -1, 1	pp	ip	2, 1, 4	σ
11	0, -1, -1, 2	pp	ip	2, 1, 6	σ
15	0, -1, -1, 3	ip	ip	2, 1, 8	σ
19	0, -1, -1, 4	pp	ip	2, 1, 10	σ

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Det. 4×	Classes	Order on		Charact.	Compn.
23	0, -1, -1, 5			2, 1, 12	σ
	1, -1, -1, 2	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 6	σd
	1, 1, -1, -2			4, 1, 6	σd^2
27	0, -1, -1, 6	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 14	σ
	1, 1, -2, -1				
	1, -1, -2, 1	<i>pp</i>	<i>3ip</i>	3(2, ± 1 , 2)	3σ
	2, -1, -1, 2				
31	0, -1, -1, 7			2, 1, 16	σ
	1, 0, -2, 1	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 8	σd
	1, 0, -2, -1			4, 1, 8	σd^2
35	0, -1, -1, 8	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 18	σ
39	0, -1, -1, 9	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 20	σ
43	0, -1, -1, 10	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 22	σ
47	0, -1, -1, 11	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 24	σ
51	0, -1, -1, 12	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 26	σ
55	0, -1, -1, 13	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 28	σ
59	0, -1, -1, 14			2, 1, 30	σ
	1, -1, -2, 1	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	6, 1, 10	σj
	1, 1, -2, -1			6, -1, 10	σj^2
63	0, -1, -1, 15	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 32	σ
67	0, -1, -1, 16	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 34	σ
71	0, -1, -1, 17	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 36	σ
75	0, -1, -1, 18	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 38	σ
79	0, -1, -1, 19	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 40	σ
83	0, -1, -1, 20			2, 1, 42	σ
	1, -1, -2, 3	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	6, -1, 14	σj^2
	1, 1, -2, -3			6, 1, 14	σj
87	0, -1, -1, 21	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 44	σ
	1, -2, 0, 3	<i>pp</i>		8, -3, 12	σg^2
	1, 2, 0, -3	<i>pp</i>		8, 3, 12	σg^4
91	0, -1, -1, 22	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 46	σ
95	0, -1, -1, 23	<i>pp</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 48	σ
99	0, -1, -1, 24	<i>ip</i>	<i>ip</i>	2, 1, 50	σ
	1, 0, -3, 3				
	1, 0, -3, -3	<i>pp</i>	<i>3ip</i>	3(2, ± 1 , 6)	3σ

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Table III. of the binary cubic forms the determinants of which are the negative numbers -972 , -1228 , 1336 , -1836 et -2700 . ($-4 \times 675 = -2700$ is beyond Arndt's Tables.)

Det. $4 \times$	Classes	Order on	Charact.	Compn.
243	0, -1, 0, 243	<i>ip</i>	1, 0, 243	1
	1, -1, -6, 0	<i>pp</i>	7, 3, 36	d
	1, 1, -6, 0	<i>pp</i>	7, -3, 36	d^2
	0, 2, 1, -30	<i>ip</i>	4, 1, 61	d_1
	2, 3, -2, -5	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	13, -2, 19	dd_1
	0, 3, 2, -8	<i>pp</i>	9, 3, 28	$d^2 d_1$
	0, -2, 1, 30	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 61	d_1^2
	0, -3, 2, 8	<i>pp</i>	9, -3, 28	dd_1^2
	2, -3, -2, 5	<i>pp</i>	13, 2, 19	$d^2 d_1^2$
	0, -1, 0, 307		1, 0, 307	1
307	1, 1, -6, -8		7, 1, 44	d
	1, -1, -6, 8		7, -1, 44	d^2
	0, 2, 1, -38		4, 1, 77	d_1
	1, -3, -2, 8	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	11, -1, 28	dd_1
	4, 1, -4, -3		17, 4, 19	$d^2 d_1$
	0, -2, 1, 38		4, -1, 77	d_1^2
	4, -1, -4, 3		17, -4, 19	dd_1^2
	1, 3, -2, -8		11, 1, 28	$d^2 d_1^2$
	0, -1, 0, 339	<i>ip</i>	1, 0, 339	1
	1, 0, -7, -4	<i>pp</i>	7, 2, 49	d
339	1, 0, -7, 4	<i>pp</i>	7, -2, 49	d^2
	0, 2, 1, -42	<i>ip</i>	4, 1, 85	d_1
	3, 0, -5, -4	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	15, 6, 25	dd_1
	2, -3, -2, 8	<i>pp</i>	13, -5, 28	$d^2 d_1$
	0, -2, 1, 42	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 85	d_1^2
	2, 3, -2, -8	<i>pp</i>	13, 5, 28	dd_1^2
	3, 0, -5, 4	<i>pp</i>	15, -6, 25	$d^2 d_1^2$
	0, -1, 0, 459	<i>ip</i>	1, 0, 459	1
	0, 3, 2, -16	<i>pp</i>	9, 3, 52	d
	0, -3, 2, 16	<i>pp</i>	9, -3, 52	d^2
459	0, 2, 1, -57	<i>ip</i>	4, 1, 115	d_1
	1, 4, -3, -4	<i>pp</i> <i>pp</i>	19, -4, 25	dd_1
	2, -1, -6, 0	<i>pp</i>	13, 3, 36	$d^2 d_1$
	0, -2, 1, 57	<i>ip</i>	4, -1, 115	d_1^2
	2, 1, -6, 0	<i>pp</i>	13, -3, 36	dd_1^2
	1, -4, -3, 4	<i>pp</i>	19, 4, 25	$d^2 d_1^2$
	0, -3, 0, 17	<i>pp</i> <i>3pp</i>	3(3, 0, 17)	$3g^3$

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Det.	Classes	Order	Charact.	Compn.
$4 \times$		on		
675	0, -1, 0, 675		1, 0, 675	1
	0, 3, 2, -24		9, 3, 76	d
	0, -3, 2, 24		9, -3, 76	d^2
	0, 2, 1, -168		4, 1, 169	d_1
	0, 5, -4, -3	<i>ip</i> <i>pp</i>	25, -10, 31	dd_1
	3, -1, -6, 0		19, 3, 36	$d^2 d_1$
	0, -1, 1, 168		4, -1, 169	d_1^2
	3, 1, -6, 0		19, -3, 36	dd_1^2
	0, -5, -4, 3		25, 10, 31	$d^2 d_1^2$

N.B. For this last determinant -4×675 , there may possibly be other cubic classes based on a non-primitive characteristic; I have not ascertained whether such forms do or do not exist.

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497.

NOTE ON THE CALCULUS OF LOGIC.

[*From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871),
pp. 282, 283.]

It appears to me that the theory of the Syllogism, as given in Boole's paper, "The Calculus of Logic," *Camb. and Dubl. Math. Jour.*, t. III. (1848), pp. 183–198, may be presented in a more concise and compendious form as follows:

We are concerned with complementary classes, X, X' ; viz. these together make up the universe (of things under consideration), $X + X' = 1$; viz. X' is the class not- X , and X the class not- X' .

Any kind whatever of simple relation between two classes (if we attend also to the complementary classes) can be expressed as a relation of total exclusion, $XY = 0$, or as a relation of partial (it may be total) inclusion, $YX \text{ not} = 0$; viz. the relation $XY = 0$ may be read in any of the forms

No X 's are Y 's,
No Y 's are X 's,
All X 's are not- Y 's,
All Y 's are not- X 's,

and the relation $XY \text{ not} = 0$ in either of the forms

Some X 's are Y 's,
Some Y 's are X 's.

I say the above are the *only* kinds of simple relations; it being understood that X' may be substituted for X , or Y' for Y ; so that the example $X'Y = 0$ (all Y 's are X 's) is the same kind of relation as $XY = 0$; and $X'Y \text{ not} = 0$ (some Y 's are not- X 's) the same kind of relation as $XY \text{ not} = 0$.

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Now taking X or X' and Z or Z' for the extreme terms, and Y or Y' for the middle term, of a syllogism; the only combinations of premises are

- (1) $XY = 0, \quad ZY = 0.$
- (2) $XY = 0, \quad ZY \text{ not } = 0, \quad \text{therefore } X'Z \text{ not } = 0.$
- (3) $XY \text{ not } = 0, \quad ZY \text{ not } = 0.$
- (4) $XY = 0, \quad ZY' = 0, \quad \text{therefore } XZ = 0.$
- (5) $XY = 0, \quad ZY' \text{ not } = 0.$
- (6) $XY \text{ not } = 0, \quad ZY' \text{ not } = 0.$

And of these, there are (as shown by the third column) only two which give rise to a conclusion (or relation between the extreme terms). As regards the negative cases, this is at once seen to be so; thus $XY = 0, ZY = 0$ (no X 's are Y 's, no Z 's are Y 's) leads to no conclusion in regard to X, Z . As regards the positive cases, it is also at once seen that the conclusions do follow; but we may obtain the conclusions by symbolical reasoning, thus

$$(2) \quad Y = YX + YX', = YX';$$

therefore $ZY = ZYX', \text{ not } = 0; \text{ therefore } ZX' \text{ not } = 0.$

$$(4) \quad XZ = XZY + XZY',$$

where on the right-hand side each term (the first as containing XY , the second as containing ZX') is $= 0$; that is, $XZ = 0$; where the logical signification of each step is obvious.

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498.

ON THE INVERSION OF A QUADRIC SURFACE.

*[From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics, vol. XI. (1871),
pp. 283–288.]*

The inversion intended to be considered is that by reciprocal radius vectors, viz. if x, y, z are rectangular coordinates, and $r^2 = x^2 + y^2 + z^2$, then x, y, z are to be changed into $\frac{x}{r^2}, \frac{y}{r^2}, \frac{z}{r^2}$. But it is convenient to introduce for homogeneity a fourth coordinate $w, = 1$; and the change then is x, y, z into

$$\frac{xw^2}{r^2}, \quad \frac{yw^2}{r^2}, \quad \frac{zw^2}{r^2}.$$

Starting from the quadric surface

$$(a, b, c, d, f, g, h, l, m, n)(x, y, z, w)^2 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h)(x, y, z)^2 + 2w(lx + my + nz) + dw^2 = 0,$$

the equation of the inverse surface is

$$w^2(a, b, c, f, g, h)(x, y, z)^2 + 2w(lx + my + nz)r^2 + dr^4 = 0,$$

where $r^2 = x^2 + y^2 + z^2$. The inverse surface is thus a quartic having the nodal conic $w = 0, x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$ (circle at infinity); and having the node $x = 0, y = 0, z = 0$ (the centre of inversion); or say it is a nodal bicircular quartic surface, or nodal anallagmatic.

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For x, y, z write

$$x - \frac{1}{2}\frac{l}{d}w, \quad y - \frac{1}{2}\frac{m}{d}w, \quad z - \frac{1}{2}\frac{n}{d}w,$$

and put for shortness

$$\begin{aligned} lx + my + nz &= u, & l^2 + m^2 + n^2 &= a, \\ al + hm + gn &= a, & hl + bm + fn &= b, & gl + fm + cn &= c, \\ (a, b, c, f, g, h)(l, m, n)^2 &= A. \end{aligned}$$

Then

$$\begin{aligned} r^2 &\text{ becomes } r^2 - \frac{uw}{d} + \frac{1}{4}\frac{a}{d^2}w^2, \\ lx + my + nz &\text{ becomes } u - \frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d}w, \\ (a, \dots)(x, y, z)^2 &\text{ becomes } (a, \dots)(x, y, z)^2 - (ax + by + cz)\frac{w}{d} + \frac{1}{4}A\frac{w^2}{d^2}. \end{aligned}$$

Hence the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} d\left\{r^4 - 2r^2\frac{uw}{d} + w^2\left(\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2}r^2 + \frac{u^2}{d^2}\right) - \frac{1}{2}\frac{auw^3}{d^3} + \frac{1}{16}\frac{a^2w^4}{d^4}\right\} \\ + 2\left(wr^2 - \frac{uw^2}{d} + \frac{1}{4}\frac{a}{d^2}w^3\right)\left(u - \frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d}w\right) \\ + w^2\left\{(a, \dots)(x, y, z)^2 - (ax + by + cz)\frac{w}{d} + \frac{1}{4}A\frac{w^2}{d^2}\right\} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

viz. arranging and reducing, this is

$$\begin{aligned} dr^4 + w^2\left\{-\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d}r^2 - \frac{u^2}{d} + (a, \dots)(x, y, z)^2\right\} \\ + w^3\left\{\frac{au}{d^2} - \frac{1}{d}(ax + by + cz)\right\} \\ + w^4\left\{-\frac{3}{16}\frac{a^2}{d^3} + \frac{1}{4}A\frac{1}{d^2}\right\} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

and we may without loss of generality assume

$$-\frac{mn}{d} + f = 0, \quad df - mn = 0; \quad -\frac{nl}{d} + g = 0, \quad dg - nl = 0; \quad -\frac{lm}{d} + h = 0, \quad dh - lm = 0.$$

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The equation then is

$$\begin{aligned} r^4 + w^2 \left\{ -\frac{1}{2} \frac{a}{d^2} (x^2 + y^2 + z^2) + \left(\frac{a}{d} - \frac{l^2}{d^2} \right) x^2 + \left(\frac{b}{d} - \frac{m^2}{d^2} \right) y^2 + \left(\frac{c}{d} - \frac{n^2}{d^2} \right) z^2 \right\} \\ + w^3 \left\{ \frac{au}{d^3} - \frac{1}{d^2} (ax + by + cz) \right\} \\ + w^4 \left\{ -\frac{1}{4d^3} (l^2 a' + m^2 b' + n^2 c') + \frac{1}{16} \frac{a^2}{d^4} \right\} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

Write

$$ad - l^2 = a'd, \quad bd - m^2 = b'd, \quad cd - n^2 = c'd.$$

We have

$$a = al + hm + gn = al + \frac{lm^2}{d} + \frac{ln^2}{d} = \frac{l}{d} (ad - l^2 + a),$$

that is

$$a = la' + \frac{la}{d},$$

and similarly

$$b = mb' + \frac{ma}{d}, \quad c = nc' + \frac{na}{d}.$$

Hence also

$$A = l^2 a' + m^2 b' + n^2 c' + \frac{a^2}{d},$$

and the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} r^4 + w^2 \left\{ \left(-\frac{1}{2} \frac{a}{d^2} + \frac{a'}{d} \right) x^2 + \left(-\frac{1}{2} \frac{a}{d^2} + \frac{b'}{d} \right) y^2 + \left(-\frac{1}{2} \frac{a}{d^2} + \frac{c'}{d} \right) z^2 \right\} \\ + w^3 \left\{ -\frac{la'}{d^2} x - \frac{mb'}{d^2} y - \frac{nc'}{d^2} z \right\} \\ + w^4 \left\{ -\frac{1}{4d^3} (l^2 a' + m^2 b' + n^2 c') + \frac{1}{16} \frac{a^2}{d^4} \right\} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

This is Kummer's form, say

$$r^4 = 4w^2 \{ a_1 x^2 + \beta_1 y^2 + \gamma_1 z^2 + \delta_1 w^2 + 2w(a_1 x + b_1 y + c_1 z) \}.$$

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Where

$$\begin{aligned} -4a_1 &= -\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} + \frac{a'}{d}, & -4\beta_1 &= -\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} + \frac{b'}{d}, & -4\gamma_1 &= -\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} + \frac{c'}{d}, \\ -4\delta_1 &= -\frac{1}{4d^3}(l^2a' + m^2b' + n^2c') + \frac{1}{16}\frac{a^2}{d^4}, \\ -8a_1 &= -\frac{la'}{d^2}, & -8b_1 &= -\frac{mb'}{d^2}, & -8c_1 &= -\frac{nc'}{d^2}. \end{aligned}$$

Hence Kummer's equation

$$\delta_1 + \lambda^2 = \frac{a_1^2}{\lambda + a_1} + \frac{b_1^2}{\lambda + \beta_1} + \frac{c_1^2}{\lambda + \gamma_1},$$

or say

$$64\delta_1 + 64\lambda^2 = \frac{256a_1^2}{4\lambda + 4a_1} + \frac{256b_1^2}{4\lambda + 4\beta_1} + \frac{256c_1^2}{4\lambda + 4\gamma_1},$$

becomes

$$\begin{aligned} 64\lambda^2 - \frac{4}{d^3}(l^2a' + m^2b' + n^2c') - \frac{a^2}{d^4} &= \frac{4l^2a'^2}{d^4(\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} - \frac{a'}{d} + 4\lambda)} \\ &+ \frac{4m^2b'^2}{d^4(\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} - \frac{b'}{d} + 4\lambda)} + \frac{4n^2c'^2}{d^4(\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} - \frac{c'}{d} + 4\lambda)}. \end{aligned}$$

This is satisfied by $4\lambda = -\frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2}$. Writing therefore

$$4\lambda + \frac{1}{2}\frac{a}{d^2} = -\frac{\theta}{d},$$

that is

$$8\lambda = -\frac{2\theta}{d} - \frac{a}{d^2}, \quad 64\lambda^2 = \frac{4\theta^2}{d^2} + \frac{4\theta a}{d^3} + \frac{a^2}{d^4},$$

the equation is

$$\frac{4\theta^2}{d^2} + \frac{4\theta a}{d^3} - \frac{4}{d^3}(l^2a' + m^2b' + n^2c') = \frac{4l^2a'^2}{d^4(-\theta/d - a'/d)} + \frac{4m^2b'^2}{d^4(-\theta/d - b'/d)} + \frac{4n^2c'^2}{d^4(-\theta/d - c'/d)}.$$

Viz. this is

$$l^2a' + m^2b' + n^2c' - \theta a - \theta^2 d = \frac{l^2a'^2}{\theta + a'} + \frac{m^2b'^2}{\theta + b'} + \frac{n^2c'^2}{\theta + c'}.$$

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which is of course satisfied by $\theta = 0$. Moreover the derived equation

$$-a - 2\theta d = -\frac{l^2 a'^2}{(\theta + a')^2} - \frac{m^2 b'^2}{(\theta + b')^2} - \frac{n^2 c'^2}{(\theta + c')^2}$$

is also satisfied by $\theta = 0$, so that this is a double root. The equation in fact is

$$\begin{aligned} & \{\theta^2 d + \theta a - (l^2 a' + m^2 b' + n^2 c')\}(\theta + a')(\theta + b')(\theta + c') \\ & + \{l^2 a'^2(\theta + b')(\theta + c') + m^2 b'^2(\theta + c')(\theta + a') + n^2 c'^2(\theta + a')(\theta + b')\} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

or, expanding and dividing by θ^2 , this is

$$\begin{aligned} & d(\theta + a')(\theta + b')(\theta + c') \\ & + a\{\theta^2 + \theta(a' + b' + c') + b'c' + c'a' + a'b'\} \\ & - (l^2 a' + m^2 b' + n^2 c')(\theta + a' + b' + c') \\ & + l^2 a'^2 + m^2 b'^2 + n^2 c'^2 = 0, \end{aligned}$$

which gives the remaining three roots.

If $a' = b' = c'$ the equation is

$$(\theta + a' + a)(\theta + a')^2 = 0.$$

I recall that we have

$$\begin{aligned} a, b, c, d, \quad f = \frac{mn}{d}, \quad g = \frac{nl}{d}, \quad h = \frac{lm}{d}, \quad l, m, n, \\ a' = a - \frac{l^2}{d}, \quad b' = b - \frac{m^2}{d}, \quad c' = c - \frac{n^2}{d}, \quad a = l^2 + m^2 + n^2, \end{aligned}$$

so that the quadric surface is

$$d(a'x^2 + b'y^2 + c'z^2) + (lx + my + nz + dw)^2 = 0,$$

and that, $a_1, \beta_1, \gamma_1, \delta_1, a_1, b_1, c_1$ denoting as before, the equation of the inverse surface (referred to a different origin) is

$$r^4 = 4w^2\{a_1x^2 + \beta_1y^2 + \gamma_1z^2 + \delta_1w^2 + 2w(a_1x + b_1y + c_1z)\}.$$

ON THE THEORY OF THE CURVE AND TORSE.

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pp. 294–317.]

The fundamental relations in the theory of the Curve and Torse were first established in my “Mémoire sur les Courbes à double courbure et sur les Surfaces développables,” Liouv. t. X. (1845), [30] see also Camb. and Dubl. Math. Jour., t. IV. (1850), [83], viz. I showed that the systems $(m, r, \beta, h, n, \gamma)$ and (r, n, m, x, α, g) , (the notation is subsequently explained), each of them satisfied the Plueckerian relations. An additional set of equations giving the values of $(\gamma, t, k, q, \gamma', t', k', q')$ was furnished by Dr Salmon’s “Theory of Reciprocal Surfaces,” Trans. R. I. Acad., t. XXIII. (1857), see also the Solid Geometry. The theory as thus established is complete in itself, but it does not take account of certain singularities v, ω, H, G ; the singularity v was first considered in my paper “On a special sextic Developable,” Quart. Math. Jour. t. VII. (1865), [373], (there called b), and I afterwards endeavoured to take account of the remaining singularities ω, H, G . I was in correspondence on the subject with Prof. Cremona, and the discovery of the complete forms of several of the formulae is due to him.

There has recently appeared a very valuable memoir by M. Zeuthen, “Sur les singularités ordinaires d’une courbe gauche et d’une surface développable,” Annali di Matem. t. III. (1869); he excludes, however, from consideration the singularity ω , and does not throughout attend to H, G .

I propose in the present memoir to reproduce and develop the whole theory.

Explanations and Notation.

1. We have a singly infinite series of points, lines, and planes; viz. each line passes through two consecutive points and lies in two consecutive planes; each plane passes through three consecutive points and contains two consecutive lines; each point

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is the intersection of three consecutive planes and of two consecutive lines. The points describe and the lines envelope a curve; the lines describe and the planes envelope a torse; the entire system of points, lines, and planes is thus the system of the curve and torse. The curve is the edge of regression or cuspidal curve of the torse; in regard to the curve the points are points (or ineunts), the lines tangents, and the planes osculating planes: in regard to the torse the points are points on the edge of regression, the lines generating lines, and the planes tangent planes.

2. Each line of the system is met by a certain number of non-consecutive lines, and the locus of the points of intersection (or say the locus of the intersection of two intersecting non-consecutive lines) is a nodal curve on the torse, or say simply it is the nodal curve. The plane containing the two intersecting non-consecutive lines envelopes a torse which is called the nexal torse.

3. There is occasion to consider

m , order of the system; this is the number of points of the system which lie in a given plane; or it is the order of the curve.

r , rank of the system; this is the number of lines of the system which meet a given line. It is thus the class of the curve; and the order of the torse.

n , class of the system; this is the number of planes of the system which pass through a given point. It is thus the class of the torse.

α , number of stationary planes; that is, planes each passing through four consecutive points of the system.

β , number of stationary points, that is, points each of them the intersection of four consecutive planes of the system.

g , number of lines in two planes (that is, lines each of them the intersection of two non-consecutive planes of the system) contained in a given plane; or say, number of apparent double planes of the torse.

G , number of double planes, or tropes, of the torse; viz. considering the torse as the envelope of a variable plane, if the plane in the course of its motion comes twice into the same position, we have then a double plane or trope.

h , number of lines through two points (that is, lines each through two non-consecutive points of the system) passing through a given point; or say, number of apparent double points of the curve.

H , number of double points, or nodes of the curve; viz. considering the curve as described by a variable point, if the point in the course of its motion comes twice into the same position we have then a double point or node of the curve.

x , number of points in two lines (that is, points each of them the intersection of two non-consecutive lines of the system) contained in a given plane; or what is the same thing, order of nodal curve.

y , number of planes through two lines (that is, planes each containing two non-consecutive lines of the system) passing through a given point; or what is the same thing, class of the nexal torse.

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v , number of stationary lines of the system, that is, lines each containing three consecutive points of the system.

ω , number of double lines of the system, that is, lines each containing two pairs of consecutive points of the system.

t , number of points on three lines (that is, points each of them the common intersection of three non-consecutive lines of the system): these are also triple points on the curve.

γ , number of points of the system, through each of which passes a non-consecutive line of the system: these are intersections of the curve with the nodal curve, stationary points on the latter curve.

k , number of apparent double points of nodal curve.

q , class of nodal curve.

t' , number of planes through three lines (that is, planes each of them through three non-consecutive lines of the system): these are also triple tangent planes of the torse.

γ' , number of planes of the system each of them passing through a non-consecutive line of the system: these are common tangent planes of the torse and nexal torse, stationary planes of the latter torse.

k' , number of apparent double planes of nexal torse.

q' , order of nexal torse.

4. The formulae thus contain in all the 21 quantities

$$m, r, n, \alpha, \beta, g, G, h, H, x, y, v, \omega, t, \gamma, k, q, t', \gamma', k', q'.$$

My own Plueckerian equations, or, say, the Pluecker-Cayley equations, establish in all 6 relations between the first 13 quantities, and thus enable the expression of them in terms of any seven, say of

$$m, r, n, G, H, v, \omega,$$

and the Salmon-Cremona equations then lead to the expressions in terms of these, of the remaining eight quantities $t, \gamma, k, q, t', \gamma', k', q'$.

I also consider

$$D_m, \text{ the deficiency of the curve, } \quad D_x, \text{ the deficiency of the nodal curve.}$$

I will first consider the equations themselves, and the mere algebraical transformations thereof; and afterwards the geometrical theory.

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The Pluecker-Cayley Equations.

5. These are found (as will be further explained) by considering first the cone, vertex an arbitrary point, which passes through the curve; and secondly, the section of the torse by an arbitrary plane. We have in the two figures

<i>Cone.</i>	<i>Section.</i>
m , order,	n , class,
r , class,	r , order,
$h + H$, double lines,	$g + G$, double tangents,
β , stationary lines,	α , stationary tangents,
$y + \omega$, double planes,	$x + \omega$, double points,
$n + v$, stationary planes	$m + v$, stationary points.

Whence the two sets of quantities respectively are connected by the Plueckerian formulae, viz. these are

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \begin{aligned}
 r &= m(m-1) - 2(h+H) - 3\beta, \\
 n &= 3m(m-2) - 6(h+H) - 8\beta, \\
 g+G &= \frac{1}{2}m(m-2)(m^2-9) - (m^2-m-6)\{2(h+H)+3\beta\} \\
 &\quad + 2(h+H)(h+H-1) + 6(h+H)\beta + \frac{9}{2}\beta(\beta-1), \\
 r &= r(r-1) - 2(y+\omega) - 3(n+v), \\
 \beta - (n+v) &= 3(r-m), \\
 h+H - (y+\omega) &= \frac{1}{2}(r-m)(r+m-9), \\
 \frac{1}{2}(r-1)(r-2) - (y+\omega) - (n+v) &= \frac{1}{2}(m-1)(m-2) - (h+H) - \beta,
 \end{aligned}
 \end{aligned}$$

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \begin{aligned}
 n &= r(r-1) - 2(x+\omega) - 3(m+v), \\
 \alpha &= 3r(r-2) - 6(x+\omega) - 8(m+v), \\
 g+G &= \frac{1}{2}r(r-2)(r^2-9) \\
 &\quad - (r^2-r-6)\{2(x+\omega)+3(m+v)\} + 2(x+\omega)(x+\omega-1) \\
 &\quad + 6(x+\omega)(m+v) + \frac{9}{2}(m+v)(m+v-1), \\
 r &= n(n-1) - 2(g+G) - 3\alpha, \\
 \alpha - (m+v) &= 3(n-r), \\
 g+G - (x+\omega) &= \frac{1}{2}(n-r)(n+r-9), \\
 \frac{1}{2}(r-1)(r-2) - (x+\omega) - (m+v) &= \frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2) - (g+G) -
 \end{aligned}
 \end{aligned}$$

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and combining the two systems

$$\begin{aligned}\beta &= \alpha + 2(m - n), & y &= x + (m - n), \\ h + H &= g + G + \frac{1}{2}(m - n)(m + n - 7), \\ \frac{1}{2}(m - 1)(m - 2) - (h + H) - \beta &= \frac{1}{2}(n - 1)(n - 2) - (g + G) - \alpha, \\ \frac{1}{2}(r - 1)(r - 2) - (x + \omega) - (m + v) &= \frac{1}{2}(r - 1)(r - 2) - (y + \omega) - (n + v).\end{aligned}$$

6. Taking as data r, m, n, G, H, v, ω , we find very easily

$$\begin{aligned}h &= \frac{1}{2}(m^2 - 10m - 3n + 8r - 3v - 2H), \\ g &= \frac{1}{2}(n^2 - 10n - 3m + 8r - 3v - 2G), \\ x &= \frac{1}{2}(r^2 - r - n - 3m - 3v - 2\omega), \\ y &= \frac{1}{2}(r^2 - r - m - 3n - 3v - 2\omega), \\ \alpha &= m - 3r + 3n + v, & \beta &= n - 3r + 3m + v.\end{aligned}$$

The Salmon-Cremona Equations.

7. These are

$$\begin{aligned}m(r - 2) &= 2n + 4\beta + \gamma + 4v + 4\omega + 4H, \\ x(r - 2) &= n(r - 4) + 2\beta + 3\gamma + 3t + v(3r - 14) + \omega(2r - 10) + 12H, \\ x(r - 2)(r - 3) &= n(x - 2r + 8) + 3mx + 4k - 3\alpha - 9\beta - 6\gamma \\ &\quad + v(3x - 6r + 18) + \omega(2x - 4r + 8) - 12H, \\ q &= x^2 - x - 2k - 3\gamma - 6t - 3v(r - 6) - 2\omega(r - 8) - 2G - 18H \\ &= \{r(n - 3) - 3\alpha - 2G\},\end{aligned}$$

and

$$\begin{aligned}n(r - 2) &= 2m + 4\alpha + \gamma' + 4v + 4\omega + 4G, \\ y(r - 2) &= m(r - 4) + 2\alpha + 3\gamma' + 3t' + v(3r - 14) + \omega(2r - 10) + 12G, \\ y(r - 2)(r - 3) &= m(y - 2r + 8) + 3ny + 4k' - 3\beta - 9\alpha - 6\gamma' \\ &\quad + v(3y - 6r + 18) + \omega(2y - 4r + 8) - 12G, \\ q' &= y^2 - y - 2k' - 3\gamma' - 6t' - 3v(r - 6) - 2\omega(r - 8) - 2H - 18G \\ &= \{r(m - 3) - 3\beta - 2H\};\end{aligned}$$

where the second values of q, q' respectively are reduced forms obtained by the aid of the foregoing Plueckerian relations.

8. Expressing these in terms of r, m, n, G, H, v, ω , we obtain

$$\begin{aligned}\gamma &= rm + 12r - 14m - 6n - 8v - 4\omega - 4H, \\ t &= \frac{1}{6}[r^3 - 3r^2 - 58r - 3r(n + 3m + 3v + 2\omega) + 42n + 78m + 78v + 48\omega], \\ k &= \frac{1}{8}[r^4 - 6r^3 + 11r^2 + 66r - (2r^2 - 10r)(n + 3m + 3v + 2\omega) \\ &\quad + (n + 3m + 3v + 2\omega)^2 - 58n - 126m - 126v - 76\omega - 24H], \\ q &= rn + 6r - 3m - 9n - 3v - 2G,\end{aligned}$$

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and

$$\begin{aligned}\gamma' &= rn + 12r - 14n - 6m - 8v - 4\omega - 4G, \\ t' &= \frac{1}{6}[r^3 - 3r^2 - 58r - 3r(m + 3n + 3v + 2\omega) + 42m + 78n + 78v + 48\omega], \\ k' &= \frac{1}{8}[r^4 - 6r^3 + 11r^2 + 66r - (2r^2 - 10r)(m + 3n + 3v + 2\omega) \\ &\quad + (m + 3n + 3v + 2\omega)^2 - 58m - 126n - 126v - 76\omega - 24G], \\ q' &= rm + 6r - 3n - 9m - 3v - 2H.\end{aligned}$$

9. We have thence

$$\begin{aligned}\gamma' - \gamma &= -(r - 8)(m - n) - 4(G - H), \\ t' - t &= (r - 6)(m - n), \\ q' - q &= (r - 6)(m - n) + 2(G - H), \\ k' - k &= \frac{1}{2}(m - n)(r^2 - 5r - 2m - 2n - 3v - 2\omega + 17) - 3(G - H) \\ &= \frac{1}{2}(m - n)(x + y - 4r + 17) - 3(G - H).\end{aligned}$$

10. Instead of obtaining the above values of γ, t, k, q directly, it is convenient to verify them by substitution in the equations from which they were obtained; viz. writing for shortness $n + 3m + 3v + 2\omega = P$, these may be written

$$\begin{aligned}-m(r - 2) + 2n + 4\beta + 4v + 4\omega + 4H + \gamma &= 0, \\ -2x(r - 2) + 2r(P - 3m) - 8n + 4\beta - 28v - 20\omega + 6\gamma + 24H + 6t &= 0, \\ -2x(r^2 - 5r + 6 - P) - 4(r - 4)n - 18\beta - 12\gamma - 6\alpha + 36v + 16\omega - 24H \\ &\quad - 4r(-n - 3m + P) + 8k = 0, \\ -4q + 2x(2x - 2) - 8k - 8G - 4r(-n - 3m + P) + 72v + 64\omega - 12\gamma - 24t - 72H &= 0,\end{aligned}$$

which are to be satisfied by

$$\begin{aligned}\gamma &= rm + 12r - 14m - 6n - 8v - 4\omega - 4H, \\ t &= \frac{1}{6}[r^3 - 3r^2 - 58r - 3rP + 42n + 78m + 78v + 48\omega], \\ k &= \frac{1}{8}[r^4 - 6r^3 + 11r^2 + 66r - (2r^2 - 10r)P + P^2 - 58n - 126m - 126v - 76\omega - 24H], \\ q &= rn + 6r - 3m - 9n - 3v - 2G, \quad x = \frac{1}{2}(r^2 - r - P), \\ \alpha &= m - 3r + 3n + v, \quad \beta = n - 3r + 3m + v, \quad P = n + 3m + 3v + 2\omega.\end{aligned}$$

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11. We have, in fact, first the substitution sum

$$\begin{aligned} & -mr + 2m + 2n + 12m + 4n - 12r + 4v + 4v + 4\omega + 4H \\ & + mr - 14m - 6n + 12r - 8v - 4\omega - 4H = 0, \end{aligned}$$

secondly

$$\begin{aligned} & -r^3 + r^2 + rP + 2r^2 - 2r - 2P + 2rP - 6mr - 8n - 12r \\ & + 4n + 12m + 4v - 28v - 20\omega + 72r + 6mr - 36n - 84m - 48v - 24\omega - 24H \\ & + 24H + r^3 - 3r^2 - 58r - 3rP + 42n + 78m + 78v + 48\omega \\ & \hline & -2P + 2n + 6m + 6v \end{aligned} = 0,$$

thirdly

$$\begin{aligned} & -r^4 + 5r^3 - 6r^2 + r^3 - 5r^2 + 6r + P(2r^2 - 6r + 6) - P^2 \\ & - 4rm + 16m + 54r - 18n - 54m - 18v - 144r - 12rm + 72n + 168m + 96v + 48\omega + 48H \\ & + 18r - 18n - 6m - 6v + 36v + 16\omega - 24H + P(-4r) + 12rm + 4rn \\ & + r^4 - 6r^3 + 11r^2 + 66r + P(-4r^2 + 10r) + P^2 - 58n - 126m - 126v - 76\omega - 24H \\ & \hline & 6P - 6n - 18m - 18v - 12\omega - 24H \end{aligned} = 0,$$

and lastly

$$\begin{aligned} & -24r - 4rm + 12m + 36n + 12v + 8G + r^4 - 2r^3 - r^2 + 2r + P(-2r^2 + 2r + 2) + P^2 \\ & + 126m + 58n + 126v + 76\omega + 24H - r^4 + 6r^3 - 11r^2 - 66r + P(2r^2 - 10r) - P^2 - 8G \\ & + P(-4r) + 4rm + 12rm + 72v + 64\omega - 144r - 12rm + 168m + 72n + 96v + 48\omega + 48H \\ & - 4r^3 + 12r^2 + 232r + P(12r) - 312m - 168n - 312v - 192\omega - 72H \\ & \hline & 2P - 6m - 2n - 6v - 4\omega \end{aligned} = 0,$$

which completes the verification.

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12. The deficiency of the curve m is given by the equation

$$2D_m = r - 2m + 2 + \beta,$$

or substituting for β its value $= n - 3r + 3m + v$, this is

$$2D_m = m + n - 2r + v + 2.$$

The deficiency of the nodal curve x is given by

$$2D_x = q - 2x + 2 + \gamma + v(r - 6) + 2H,$$

which, substituting for q, x, γ , the values

$$\begin{aligned} rn + 6r - 3m - 9n - 3v - 2G, \\ \frac{1}{2}(r^2 - r - n - 3m - 3v - 2\omega), \\ rm + 12r - 14m - 6n - 8v - 4\omega - 4H, \end{aligned}$$

respectively, becomes

$$2D_x = (r - 14)(m + n + v) - r^2 + 19r + 2 - 2\omega - 2G - 2H;$$

whence, also, writing herein $m + n + v = 2D_m + 2r - 2$, we have

$$2D_x - (r - 14)2D_m = (r - 5)(r - 6) - 2\omega - 2G - 2H,$$

a relation between the two deficiencies.

Geometrical Theory of the foregoing Relations.

13. In considering the geometrical theory, we have to speak of the original curve, or curve of the system, and also of the nodal curve; it will be convenient to call them the curve m and the curve x respectively. I speak of the torse absolutely, to signify the torse of the system, as in what follows there is not the like occasion to speak of the nexal torse. I speak also of a plane α , meaning thereby any one of the stationary planes, the number of which is $= \alpha$; and so of a line α , meaning the line in the stationary plane α ; and a point α , meaning the point of contact of such line with the curve m ; or in the plural, the planes α , lines α , &c. And so in other cases; thus we have the stationary tangents v , and the points v , which are the points of contact hereof with the curve m . As regards a double tangent ω , we have here two points of contact; one of these separately would be a point ω ; and we may speak of the points (or pair) 2ω , meaning thereby the two points of contact of the same tangent ω ; or of the points 2ω , meaning the system of the 2ω points of contact of the tangents ω .

14. Observe that the expressions, the planes α , lines α , &c., have an absolute signification; there are other such expressions which have only a relative signification, in regard to the system considered in connexion with a given point, line, or plane, as the case may require. Thus the expression, the lines g , must be understood of the system in connexion with a given plane, to signify the lines in two planes contained in the given plane; the planes g , points g , would of course mean the planes or points of the system belonging to the lines g .

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In particular the points m are the points of the system which lie in a given plane, the lines r are the lines which meet a given line; the planes n are the planes which pass through a given point. There will be occasion to speak, not only of the planes n , but also of the lines n and points n ; these are of course the lines and points in the planes n .

15. It is to be remarked that, considering the torse as a surface, the nodal curve thereof is made up of the curve x and of the double lines ω (or its order is $= x + \omega$); the cuspidal curve is made up of the curve m , and of the stationary lines v (or its order is $= m + v$).

The Pluecker-Cayley Equations.

16. The mode of obtaining these equations has already been indicated. We in fact consider the system in connexion with an arbitrary point, and with an arbitrary plane. The point is the vertex of a cone passing through the curve m , and this cone is of the order m , the class r , with $h + H$ double lines, β stationary lines, $y + \omega$ double tangent planes, and $n + v$ stationary tangent planes; viz. the order of the cone is equal to the number of lines in which this is intersected by a plane through the vertex; but each of these is determined as the line joining the vertex with an intersection of the plane by the curve m , and the number of them is thus $= m$. The class of the cone is equal to the number of the tangent planes which can be drawn through an arbitrary line through the vertex; but this is in fact the number of lines of the system which meet the arbitrary line, viz. it is $= r$. Again, any line drawn from the vertex to meet the curve twice, and also any line drawn to one of the points H , is a double line of the cone, that is, the whole number of double lines is $= h + H$. A line from the vertex to one of the points β is a stationary line of the cone; the number of these is $= \beta$. A plane through the vertex, and containing two tangents of the curve m , or containing a double tangent ω , is a double tangent plane of the cone, the number of these is thus $= y + \omega$. A plane through the vertex, which is also a plane of the system, is a stationary tangent plane; in fact, we have here on the curve m three consecutive points lying in a plane with the vertex, the tangent plane of the cone is the plane through the vertex, and the first and second of the points on the curve; but this is also the plane through the vertex, and the second and third points, or the plane is a stationary tangent plane. But the plane through the vertex and the tangent v is also a stationary tangent plane of the cone; and the number of stationary tangent planes is thus $= n + v$.

17. Similarly for the section by the arbitrary plane; this is a curve of the order r and class n with $x + \omega$ double points, $m + v$ stationary points, $g + G$ double tangents, and α stationary tangents. In fact, the order of the curve is equal to that of the torse; that is, to the number of lines which meet an arbitrary line, or $= r$. The class of the curve is equal to the number of tangents which pass through an arbitrary point of the plane; or, what is the same thing, the number of planes of the system which pass through this same arbitrary point, viz. it is $= n$. Each point of the plane which is the intersection of two lines of the system, and also each intersection of the plane by a line ω , is a double point of the curve; viz. the number of these is $= x + \omega$. Each intersection with the curve m , and also each intersection with the tangent v , is a stationary point of the curve; viz. the number is $= m + v$.

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Each line in the plane, which is the intersection of two planes of the system, and also each intersection of the plane with a double tangent plane G , is a double tangent of the curve; viz. the number is $= g + G$. And, finally, each intersection of the plane with a stationary plane α is a stationary tangent of the curve; viz. the number of these is $= \alpha$.

We have thus the Plueckerian relations as above between

$$m, r, h + H, \beta, y + \omega, n + v,$$

and between

$$n, r, g + G, \alpha, x + \omega, m + v.$$

Zeuthen's Tables.

18. The vertex of the cone and the plane of the section may occupy special positions. We have a table given by Zeuthen, but which I have completed so far as regards the double lines ω as follows:

Cone through the Curve.

	Vertex	Order	Class	Double lines	Stationary lines	Double tangent planes	Stationary tangent planes
1	Arbitrary	m	r	$h + H$	β	$y + \omega$	$n + v$
2	On a tangent	m	$r - 1$	$h - 1 + H$	$\beta + 1$	$y - r + 4 + \omega$	$n - 2 + v$
3	On the curve	$m - 1$	$r - 2$	$h - m + 2 + H$	β	$y - 2r + 8 + \omega$	$n - 3 + v$
4	At a point H	$m - 2$	$r - 4$	$h - 2m + 6 + H - 1$	β	$y - 4r + 20 + \omega$	$n - 6 + v$
5	At a point β	$m - 2$	$r - 3$	$h - 2m + 6 + H$	$\beta - 1$	$y - 3r + 13 + \omega$	$n - 4 + v$
6	On stationary tangent v	m	$r - 2$	$h - 2 + H$	$\beta + 2$	$y - 2r + 9 + \omega$	$n - 3 + v - 1$
7	At point of contact of ditto	$m - 1$	$r - 3$	$h - m + 1 + H$	$\beta + 1$	$y - 3r + 14 + \omega$	$n - 4 + v - 1$
8	On double tangent ω	m	$r - 2$	$h - 2 + H$	$\beta + 2$	$y - 2r + 10 + \omega - 1$	$n - 4 + v$
9	At point of contact of ditto	$m - 1$	$r - 3$	$h - m + 1 + H$	$\beta + 1$	$y - 3r + 15 + \omega - 1$	$n - 5 + v$

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Plane Section of the Torse.

	Plane	Class	Order	Double tangents	Stationary tangents	Double points	Stationary points
1	Arbitrary	n	r	$g + G$	α	$x + \omega$	$m + v$
2	Through a tangent	n	$r - 1$	$g - 1 + G$	$\alpha + 1$	$x - r + 4 + \omega$	$m - 2 + v$
3	A tangent plane	$n - 1$	$r - 2$	$g - n + 2 + G$	α	$x - 2r + 8 + \omega$	$m - 3 + v$
4	A double tangent plane G	$n - 2$	$r - 4$	$g - 2n + 6 + G - 1$	α	$x - 4r + 20 + \omega$	$m - 6 + v$
5	A stationary tangent plane α	$n - 2$	$r - 3$	$g - 2n + 6 + G$	$\alpha - 1$	$x - 3r + 13 + \omega$	$m - 4 + v$
6	Through stationary tangent v	n	$r - 2$	$g - 2 + G$	$\alpha + 2$	$x - 2r + 9 + \omega$	$m - 3 + v - 1$
7	Tangent plane at contact of ditto	$n - 1$	$r - 3$	$g - n + 1 + G$	$\alpha + 1$	$x - 3r + 14 + \omega$	$m - 4 + v - 1$
8	Through double tangent ω	n	$r - 2$	$g - 2 + G$	$\alpha + 2$	$x - 2r + 10 + \omega - 1$	$m - 4 + v$
9	A tangent plane at one contact of ditto	$n - 1$	$r - 3$	$g - n + 1 + G$	$\alpha + 1$	$x - 3r + 15 + \omega - 1$	$m - 5 + v$

19. To avoid confusion with the geometrical term line, I will speak (not of the lines, but) of the cases of these tables; the numbers in each case satisfy the foregoing Plueckerian relations. To fix the ideas, I attend to the second table. We require to know in each case, say the numbers in the (n, r, α) columns; these being known, the other three numbers will be determined.

20. First for the n column; for the Cases 2, 6, 8, the plane is not a tangent plane; the number of tangent planes which pass through a fixed point in the plane is still $= n$. For Cases 3, 7, 9, the plane is a tangent plane, it therefore counts 1 among the tangent planes which pass through a fixed point thereof; and the number of the remaining tangent planes is $= n - 1$. And so for Cases 4 and 5, the plane counts for 2 among the tangent planes which pass through a fixed point thereof, and the number of the remaining tangent planes is $= n - 2$.

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21. Next as to the r and α columns.

Case (2). The plane passes through a generating line, and therefore besides cuts the torse in a curve of the order $r - 1$; this generating line is a stationary tangent cutting the curve $r - 1$ in the point of contact with the curve m , counting 3 times (in all $\alpha + 1$ stationary tangents), and in $r - 4$ other points.

Case (3). The plane cuts the torse in the generating line counting twice, and in a curve of the order $r - 2$; the generating line is in regard to this curve an ordinary tangent at the point of contact with the curve m (so that the number of stationary tangents remains $= \alpha$), and besides cuts the curve in $r - 4$ points as in Case 2.

Case (4). The plane cuts the torse in two generating lines, each counting twice, and in a curve of the order $r - 4$; each of the generating lines is in regard to this curve an ordinary tangent at the point of contact with the curve m (number of stationary tangents remains $= \alpha$), and besides cuts the curve in $r - 6$ other points.

Case (5). The plane cuts the torse in a generating line counting 3 times, and in a curve of the order $r - 3$; the generating line is in regard to this curve an ordinary tangent at the point of contact with the curve m , and besides cuts it in $r - 5$ points. The plane being in the present case a plane α , its intersections with the remaining planes α , give the $\alpha - 1$ stationary tangents.

Case (6). The plane meets the torse in a generating line counting twice, and in a curve of the order $r - 2$; the generating line is in regard to the curve a singular tangent meeting it in the point of contact with the curve m , counting 4 times, and besides meeting it in $r - 6$ points. The generating line in respect of this four-pointic intersection counts as a stationary tangent twice; and the number of stationary tangents is $= \alpha + 2$.

Case (7). The plane meets the torse in the generating line counting 3 times, and in a curve of the order $r - 3$; the generating line is in regard to this curve a stationary tangent at the point of contact with the curve m , counting 3 times, and besides meeting it in $r - 6$ points as in Case 6. The whole number of stationary tangents is thus $= \alpha + 1$.

Case (8). The plane meets the torse in a generating line counting twice and in a curve of the order $r - 2$. The generating line is in respect of the curve a stationary tangent at each of the points of contact with the curve m , viz. each of these points counts 3 times, and there are besides $r - 8$ intersections. Moreover, the generating line counting as 2 stationary tangents, the whole number of stationary tangents is $= \alpha + 2$.

Case (9). The plane meets the torse in a generating line counting 3 times, and in a curve of the order $r - 3$. The generating line is in respect of the curve an ordinary tangent at one of the points of contact with the curve m (viz. the point at which the plane is a tangent plane of the torse), so that we have here two intersections; and it is a stationary tangent at the other of the points of contact with the curve m (viz. the point at which the plane is not a tangent plane of the torse),

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Thus there are 3 intersections at the latter point, and $r - 8$ other intersections. The generating line reckons once as a stationary tangent, and the whole number of stationary tangents is $= \alpha + 1$.

22. The $r - 6$ points in Cases 6 and 7 are the points of intersection of the stationary tangent v by other tangents of the curve m ; and so the $r - 8$ points in Cases 8 and 9 are the points of intersection of the double tangent ω by other tangents of the curve m ; these numbers $r - 6$ and $r - 8$ will present themselves in the sequel.

We may as to the α -column sum up by saying, that in Cases 2, 7, 9 there is a generating line which reckons as a stationary tangent; in Case 6 a generating line, which, in respect of 4 consecutive intersections, reckons as two stationary tangents; and in Case 8 a generating line, which, in respect of two pairs of 3 consecutive intersections, reckons as two stationary tangents.

In the $(x + \omega)$ and $(m + v)$ -columns, observe that in Cases 6, 7, 8, 9, we have in the first two $\omega, v - 1$, and in the last two $\omega - 1, v$; viz. these numbers refer to the intersections of the plane with the tangent ω, v respectively. So in the $g + G$ column in Case 4, we have $G - 1$ for G .

The Nodal Curve x ; Intersections with the Curve m ; and Singularities.

23. The intersections of the curve m with the nodal curve x , are points $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, H, v$ or ω .

24. At a point α , four consecutive points of the curve m lie in a plane; the point may be considered as the intersection of two consecutive tangents. We may imagine the points A, A' starting from α in opposite directions along the curve m , and moving in such manner that the tangents at these two points respectively continually intersect; we have thus a portion of the curve x , proceeding apparently in one direction only from the point α ; and being, as regards the portion in question, an intersection of two real sheets of the torse; that is, a crunodal curve. The curve x , however, really extends in the opposite direction from α , but it is as to this portion thereof an intersection of two imaginary sheets of the torse; that is, an acnodal curve. The nodal curve x thus meets the curve m in the several points α , the curve x , each time that it passes through such a point of intersection, changing its character from crunodal to acnodal. The two half-sheets¹ of the torse cross each other in the crunodal portion, extending

¹ In a curve (plane or twisted), the portions extending each way from a cusp are called half-branches; and so in a surface which has a cuspidal curve, or in particular in a torse, the portions extending each way from the cuspidal curve are called half-sheets.

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The acnodal portion extends in the opposite direction from the same point.

25. A point β , or stationary point (cusp) on the curve m , is the intersection of four consecutive osculating planes; and it is thus a point of intersection of two consecutive tangents (viz. of the line of intersection of two consecutive osculating planes, and of that of the next two consecutive osculating planes), consequently a point on the curve x . We may imagine the points B, B' starting from β , and moving along the two half-branches of the curve m , in such manner that the tangents at the two points respectively continually intersect. We have thus a portion of the curve x , proceeding apparently in one direction only from the point β (and having at this point a common tangent with the curve m), and being as regards this portion thereof an intersection of two real sheets of the torse; that is, a crunodal curve. The curve x , however, really extends in the opposite direction from the point β , but it is as to this portion thereof an intersection of two imaginary sheets of the torse; that is, an acnodal curve. The nodal curve thus meets the curve m in each of the points β , the curve x , each time that it passes through such a point, changing its character from crunodal to acnodal. There are at β three partial sheets of the torse; viz. if we imagine at this point the half-tangent b in the sense of the two half-branches of the curve m , and the half-tangent b' in the opposite sense, then we have through b' and one of the half-branches a partial sheet, and through b' and the other half-branch a partial sheet; these two partial sheets touching along b' , and intersecting in the crunodal portion of the curve x ; and a third partial sheet through b and the two half-branches of the curve m .

26. At a point γ on the cuspidal curve m , we have, traversing the curve and the two half-sheets which meet along it, another sheet of the torse, meeting the two half-sheets respectively in two half-branches, which are a portion of the nodal curve x , and which unite together (as at a cusp), in the point γ , which is thus a cusp or stationary point on the curve x .

27. A point H is the intersection of two branches of the cuspidal curve m . There are for each branch two half-sheets; and we have thus at the point H four (say) quarter-branches of the curve x , touching each other at the point (viz. the common tangent is the intersection of the osculating planes belonging to the two branches of the curve m respectively). I find in a special manner that in regard to the curve x a point H is equivalent to six double points, plus two stationary points; it thus causes a reduction $2 \cdot 6 + 3 \cdot 2 = 18$ in the class of the curve.

28. The nodal curve x has in each of the double tangent planes G an actual double point. In fact the plane is an osculating plane of the curve m at two points thereof; that is, it contains two consecutive tangents R, R' , and two other consecutive tangents S, S' ; hence RS is a point on the nodal curve x ; and not only so, but this is an actual double point, the two tangents being R and S ; for since R is met by S and S' , there is a consecutive point on the line R ; that is, R is a tangent; and similarly since S is met by R and R' there is a consecutive point on the line S ; that is, S is also a tangent.

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29. At a point v the tangent has with the curve x a 3-pointic intersection (whence also the tangent is a stationary tangent v in regard to the curve x), the curves m and x have also a 3-pointic intersection at v .

30. At each of the two points ω the tangent has with the curve x a 3-pointic intersection (viz. the tangent is in regard to the curve x more than a double tangent ω , instead of two 2-pointic intersections, or ordinary contacts, there are two 3-pointic intersections; I am unable to perceive this directly, but accept it on other grounds). But as at each of the points ω the intersection of the tangent with the curve m is 2-pointic, the intersection of the curves x and m is only 2-pointic.

31. The curves m and x meet in the points α each once, β each 3 times, γ each twice, v each 3 times, 2ω each twice, and H each 8 times: we have thus

$$\alpha + 3\beta + 2\gamma + 3v + 4\omega + 8H$$

for the number of actual intersections of the two curves; and the number of apparent intersections is therefore

$$= mx - \alpha - 3\beta - 2\gamma - 3v - 4\omega - 8H,$$

a result which is required in the sequel.

32. Consider the cone (vertex an arbitrary point) through the curve x , or say simply the cone x .

Each line n (quà ordinary line of the system) is met by $r - 4$ other lines, the $r - 4$ points being situate on the curve x ; the line n at each of these points touches the cone x , and it therefore besides intersects it in $x - 2r + 8$ points.

33. A line v meets the curve x in the point v counting 3 times, and in $r - 6$ points each a stationary point of the curve; it consequently meets the cone x , in the point v counting 3 times, in each of the $r - 6$ points counting twice, and besides in $x - 2r + 9$ points.

34. A line ω meets the curve x in the two points ω each counting 3 times, and in $r - 8$ points each an actual double point of the curve; it consequently meets the cone x in the two points ω each counting 3 times, in the $r - 8$ points each counting twice, and besides in $x - 2r + 10$ points.

35. Each of the $r - 8$ points in which the double tangent ω meets another tangent of m is an actual double point of the curve x ; and each of the $r - 6$ points in which a stationary tangent v meets another tangent of m is a stationary point or cusp on the curve x . We have thus as singularities of the curve x , the k apparent double points, G actual double points, $\omega(r - 8)$ ditto, t triple points, H 4-branch cuspidal points, γ stationary or cuspidal points, $v(r - 6)$ ditto. In regard to the effect upon the class of the curve x , each of the points t is equivalent to 3 double points and produces a reduction $= 6$; each of the points H is equivalent to 6 double points + 2 cusps, and produces a reduction $2 \cdot 6 + 3 \cdot 2 = 18$, as already mentioned. We have thus the relation

$$q = x(x - 1) - 2k - 2G - 3v(r - 6) - 2\omega(r - 8) - 3\gamma - 6t - 18H,$$

which is one of the Salmon-Cremona equations.

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36. The stationary points of the curve x are the points γ , the $v(r-6)$ points, and the points H , each counting as 2 stationary points; that is, we have

$$2D_x = q - 2x + 2 + \gamma + v(r-6) + 2H,$$

used above for finding the value of the deficiency D_x .

The remaining Salmon-Cremona Equations.

37. The formulae for $m(r-2)$, $x(r-2)$ and $x(r-2)(r-3)$ correspond to those for $c(n-2)$, $b(n-2)$ and $b(n-2)(n-3)$ in the case of a general surface (Solid Geometry, 2nd Ed., Nos. 522 and 525 [4th Ed., Nos. 610, 613]), being obtained as follows; considering as before the cone, vertex an arbitrary point, which passes through the curve m , the total number of lines hereof which have with the torse a 3-pointic intersection at the curve m is $= m(r-2)$; and, similarly, considering the cone, vertex the same arbitrary point, which passes through the curve x , the total number of lines hereof which have with the torse a 3-pointic intersection at the curve x is $= x(r-2)$; viz. these numbers $m(r-2)$ and $x(r-2)$ are the numbers of the intersections of the two curves respectively with the surface of the order $r-2$, which is the second polar of the arbitrary point in regard to the torse. And so also in the cone, vertex the arbitrary point, which passes through the curve x , the total number of lines which touch the torse at a point not on the curve x is $= x(r-2)(r-3)$; viz. this is obtained by Salmon, the number of intersections of the curve x with a certain surface of the order $(r-2)(r-3)$ (Salmon, Nos. 269 and 273, writing r for n), but in a preferable manner by Cremona thus; the cone through the curve x meets the torse in the curve x counting twice and in a residual curve of the order $x(r-2)$; the lines in question are the tangents from the vertex to this curve, which is a curve meeting each line of the cone $r-2$ times; we may on the surface of the cone metrically, as in the plane, construct the polar of the vertex in regard to the curve of the order $x(r-2)$; viz. we have thus on the cone a curve meeting each generating line $r-3$ times; and this polar curve meets the curve of the order $x(r-2)$ in $x(r-2)(r-3)$ points (this would be clearly the case if only the curve of the order $x(r-2)$ were the complete intersection of the cone by a surface of the order $r-2$, for then the polar curve would be the intersection of the cone by the polar surface of the order $r-3$; but in the case in hand, where this is not so, some additional considerations would be required in order to sustain the result), and we have thus the number $x(r-2)(r-3)$ of the lines in question.

38. I consider the second polar surface, order $r-2$, which belongs to a given arbitrary point. Any point on the torse, such that the line joining it with the arbitrary point cuts the torse 3-pointically at the point on the torse, is a point on the second polar $r-2$. Such points are, as will be shewn, the points

$$n, n(r-4), \beta, \gamma, v, 2\omega, v(r-6), \omega(r-8), t, H.$$

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39. For the points n and $n(r-4)$, the plane may be taken to be the osculating plane of the curve m . This meets the torse in the line n twice, and in a curve of the order $r-2$ touching this line at the point n and meeting it in the $r-4$ points. Hence, considering the complete section made up of the line twice and the curve of the order $r-2$, the line from the arbitrary point to the point n or to any one of the $r-4$ points meets the section 3-pointically; viz. the lines to the points n and to the points $n(r-4)$ meet the torse 3-pointically.

40. For the points β ; we may consider any section through the arbitrary point and β ; in effect any section through the point β . A plane section through a point β has at this point an invisible triple point, that is a point not in appearance differing from an ordinary point of the curve, but which by considering a consecutive position of the plane of section is seen to be equivalent to a double point and two cusps; viz. the node is a point of intersection of the plane with the curve x , the cusps are the two intersections with the curve m , in the neighbourhood of the point β . The line from β to the arbitrary point has thus with the torse a 3-pointic intersection at β .

41. Similarly for the points γ ; we take any section through the arbitrary point and γ ; in effect any section through the point γ . The section through a point γ has at this point a triple point, at which an ordinary branch passes through a cusp, and thus equivalent to a cusp +2 nodes; in fact, for a consecutive position of the cutting plane, the section has actually a cusp and two nodes; the cusp at the intersection of the plane with the curve m , the nodes at the two intersections of the plane with the curve x in the neighbourhood of the cusp γ . The line through the point γ has thus a 3-pointic intersection with the torse.

42. For a point v I consider the section through the tangent v ; this is made up of the tangent twice, and of a curve of the order $r-2$ having with the tangent a 4-pointic intersection at the point v , and besides meeting it in $r-6$ points. Thus the lines through the points v and $v(r-6)$ respectively have a 3-pointic intersection with the torse.

43. Similarly for a point ω , I consider the section through a tangent ω ; this is made up of the tangent twice, and of a curve of the order $r-2$ having with the tangent a 3-pointic intersection at each of the points ω , and besides meeting it in $r-8$ points. Thus the lines through the points 2ω and $\omega(r-8)$ respectively have a 3-pointic intersection with the torse.

44. For a point H I consider any section through the arbitrary point and H ; in effect any section through H . There is at H a singularity = 6 nodes +2 cusps. But a line through H in the plane of the section cuts the section in 4 points only; that is, the line from the arbitrary point to H has with the curve a 4-pointic intersection at H ; and a fortiori it may be regarded as a line of 3-pointic intersection. The lines to the points H have thus a (4-pointic, that is, more than) 3-pointic intersection with the torse.

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45. For a point t I consider any section through the arbitrary point and t ; there is at t a triple point, and the line through t has thus a 3-pointic intersection at t . Hence a line through t has 3-pointic intersections with the torse.

46. The several points above referred to lie on the curve m or on the curve x , or on both of these curves; and each curve has at these points respectively a simple or multiple intersection with the polar surface $r - 2$, as shown in the table.

Points	curve m	curve x
n	2	0
$n(r - 4)$	0	1
β	4	2
γ	1	3
v	4	4
2ω	2	3
$v(r - 6)$	0	3
$\omega(r - 8)$	0	2
H	4	12
t	0	3

where the figures 1, 2, &c. denote a simple intersection, 2-pointic intersection, &c. of the curve and surface; 0 denotes of course that there is not any intersection, viz. that the curve does not pass through the point referred to.

47. Several of the foregoing numbers are obtained without difficulty; thus we see that the points $n, n(r - 4)$ are ordinary points on the second polar $r - 2$, the surface at each of the points n touching the curve m , but at each of the points $n(r - 4)$ simply cutting the curve x . So also the points $\beta, \gamma, v, 2\omega, v(r - 6), \omega(r - 8)$ are ordinary points on the second polar; at a point β the two half-branches of the curve m touch the surface in a special manner so as to give a 4-pointic intersection; whereas the curve x simply touches the surface. At γ the curve m cuts the surface, but the two half-branches of x touch the surface. At v , each of the curves m, x has a 4-pointic intersection with the surface; at each of the two points ω , the curve m touches the surface, but the curve x has with it a 3-pointic intersection, and at $\omega(r - 8)$ it simply touches the surface.

48. The point H is in the nature of a biplanar point on the polar surface; this appears, or is at least indicated, by the circumstance that the line to the arbitrary point has with the torse (not a 3-pointic but) a 4-pointic intersection: the two branches of the curve m each simply cut the two coincident sheets of the polar surface, giving $2 \times 2 = 4$ intersections; but for the curve x , the four partial branches each touch the

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two coincident sheets; for a single sheet the number of intersections would be 6, but for the two coincident sheets it is twice this, or = 12. Finally, a point t is an ordinary point on the second polar, each of the three branches of x simply cuts the surface, or the number of intersections is = 3.

49. The last table gives at once

$$\begin{aligned} m(r-2) &= 2n + 4\beta + \gamma + 4v + 2 \cdot 2\omega + 4H, \\ x(r-2) &= n(r-4) + 2\beta + 3\gamma + 4v + 3 \cdot 2\omega + 3v(r-6) + 2\omega(r-8) + 12H + 3t, \end{aligned}$$

which are the true theoretical forms of the equations for $m(r-2)$ and $x(r-2)$, in which these were obtained by Cremona.

50. The $x(r-2)(r-3)$ points are those points in which the Cremona $x(r-2)$ curve is met 2-pointically by the line from the arbitrary point; viz. these points are either points of contact of tangents from the vertex to the $x(r-2)$ curve, or they are double points, or else cusps of the $x(r-2)$ curve; in which several cases respectively they count 1, 2 or 3 times, among the $x(r-2)(r-3)$ points.

51. The points of contact are the $n(x-2r+8)$ points of intersection of the lines n with the cone x . We have in fact a plane n through the vertex of the cone, and in this plane two consecutive lines of the system; hence at each of the $x-2r+8$ points the generating line of the cone meets the two consecutive lines of the system; that is, there is with the curve $x(r-2)$ a 2-pointic intersection, not arising out of any singularity of the curve, and consequently a contact of this curve with the generating line of the cone.

52. The actual double points of the curve $x(r-2)$ are first the $2k$ apparently coincident points of the curve x , and secondly the $\omega(x-2r+10)$ points on the lines ω . For first if we consider through the vertex a line meeting the curve x in two points, say A, B , this meets the torse in these points each twice and in $r-4$ other points. Now imagine a line from the vertex to the point P in the vicinity of A ; as P travels through A , two of the $r-2$ points come together at B , and again separate; that is B is an actual double point on the $x(r-2)$ curve; and similarly A is an actual double point on the curve; and we have thus the $2k$ double points. Secondly, since the line ω is a nodal line on the torse, a generating line of the cone, in the neighbourhood of and considered as travelling through one of the $x-2r+10$ points, meets the torse in two points which come to coincide and then again separate; that is each of the $x-2r+10$ points is an actual double point on the curve $x(r-2)$; and the whole number of these is $\omega(x-2r+10)$.

53. The stationary points of the curve $x(r-2)$ are first the points on the curve m which apparently coincide with the curve x ; viz. the number of these is

$$mx - \alpha - 3\beta - 2\gamma - 3v - 4\omega - 8H;$$

secondly, the $v(x-2r+9)$ points on the lines v ;

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thirdly, the points H each counting as 4 cusps. For first consider a generating line meeting the curve x in B and the curve x in A ; if we imagine on the curve x a point Q which approaches and ultimately coincides with B , the generating line through Q meets the torse in the neighbourhood of its cuspidal edge in two points which come ultimately to coincide with the point A , and we thus see that A is a stationary point on the $x(r-2)$ curve.

54. Secondly, observing that the line v is a cuspidal line on the torse, and considering in like manner a generating line of the x cone, which approaches and comes ultimately to coincide with one of the $x-2r+9$ points, we see that this is a stationary point on the $x(r-2)$ curve. And thirdly, any line through a point H meets the torse in this point counting 4 times, and in $r-4$ other points. Hence considering the generating line of the x cone, which travelling along any one of the four partial branches of the x curve comes ultimately to coincide with H , 2 of the $r-2$ points on such generating line come to coincide at the point H ; and we have thus the point H as a singular point on the $x(r-2)$ curve; viz. it reckons as a stationary point once in respect of each of the four partial branches of the curve x (it must be assumed that this is so, but a further proof is required), that is as 4 cusps on the $x(r-2)$ curve.

55. By what precedes we have

$$\begin{aligned} x(r-2)(r-3) &= n(x-2r+8) \\ &\quad + 2\{2k + \omega(x-2r+10)\} \\ &\quad + 3\{(mx - \alpha - 3\beta - 2\gamma - 3v - 4\omega - 8H) + v(x-2r+9) + 4H\}, \end{aligned}$$

which is the true theoretical form in which the equation for $x(r-2)(r-3)$ was obtained by Cremona.

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On a Theorem Relating to Eight Points on a Conic.

[From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 344–346.]

THE following is a known theorem:

“In any octagon inscribed in a conic, the two sets of alternate sides intersect in the 8 points of the octagon and in 8 other points lying in a conic.”

In fact the two sets of sides are each of them a quartic curve, hence any quartic curve through 13 of the 8 + 8 points passes through the remaining 3 points: but the original conic together with a conic through 5 of the 8 new points form together such a quartic curve; and hence the remaining 3 of the new points (inasmuch as obviously they are not situate on the original conic) must be situate on the conic through the 5 new points, that is the 8 new points must lie on a conic.

We may without loss of generality take

$$(\alpha_1^2, \alpha_1, 1), (\alpha_2^2, \alpha_2, 1), \dots, (\alpha_8^2, \alpha_8, 1)$$

as the coordinates (x, y, z) of the 8 points of the octagon; and obtain hereby an *a posteriori* verification of the theorem, by finding the equation of the conic through the 8 new points: the result contains cyclical expressions of an interesting form.

Calling the points of the octagon 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6, 7, 8, the 8 new points are

$$12.45, \quad 23.56, \quad 34.67, \quad 45.78, \quad 56.81, \quad 67.12, \quad 78.23, \quad 81.34,$$

viz. 12.45 is the intersection of the lines 12 and 45; and so on. The 8 points lie on a conic, the equation of which is to be found.

The equation of the line 12 is

$$x - (\alpha_1 + \alpha_2)y + \alpha_1\alpha_2z = 0,$$

or as it is convenient to write it

$$x - (1 + 2)y + 12.z = 0,$$

viz. 1, 2, &c., are for shortness written in place of α_1, α_2 , &c. respectively.

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The coordinates of the 12.45 are consequently proportional to the terms of

$$\begin{array}{lll} 1, & -(1 + 2), & 12, \\ 1, & -(4 + 5), & 45, \end{array}$$

or say they are as

$$12(4 + 5) - 45(1 + 2) : 12 - 45 : 1 + 2 - (4 + 5).$$

The equation of the line (12.45)(23.56) which joins the points 12.45 and 23.56 thus is

$$\begin{vmatrix} x & y & z \\ 12(4 + 5) - 45(1 + 2) & 12 - 45 & (1 + 2) - (4 + 5) \\ 23(5 + 6) - 56(2 + 3) & 23 - 56 & (2 + 3) - (5 + 6) \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

where the determinant vanishes identically if $2 - 5 = 0$ ($\alpha_2 - \alpha_5 = 0$); it in fact thereby becomes

$$\begin{vmatrix} x & y & z \\ 2^2(1 - 4) & 2(1 - 4) & 1 - 4 \\ 2^2(3 - 6) & 2(3 - 6) & 3 - 6 \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

The determinant divides therefore by $2 - 5$; the coefficient of x is easily found to be

$$= (2 - 5)(12 - 23 + 34 - 45 + 56 - 61),$$

and so for the other terms; and omitting the factor $2 - 5$ the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & x\{12 - 23 + 34 - 45 + 56 - 61\} \\ & - y\{12(4 + 5) - 23(5 + 6) + 34(6 + 1) - 45(1 + 2) + 56(2 + 3) - 61(3 + 4)\} \\ & + z\{1234 - 2345 + 3456 - 4561 + 5612 - 6123\} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

There is now not much difficulty in forming the equation of the required conic; viz. this is

$$\begin{aligned} & 67\{x[12 - 23 + 34 - 45 + 56 - 61] \\ & - y[12(4 + 5) - 23(5 + 6) + 34(6 + 1) - 45(1 + 2) + 56(2 + 3) - 61(3 + 4)] \\ & + z[1234 - 2345 + 3456 - 4561 + 5612 - 6123]\} \\ & - 12\{x[23 - 34 + 45 - 56 + 67 - 72] \\ & - y[23(5 + 6) - 34(6 + 7) + 45(7 + 2) - 56(2 + 3) + 67(3 + 4) - 72(4 + 5)] \\ & + z[2345 - 3456 + 4567 - 5672 + 6723 - 7234]\} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

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In fact this equation written with an indeterminate coefficient λ , say, for shortness, thus

$$67[(12.45)(23.56)] = \lambda 12[(23.56)(34.67)] = 0,$$

is the general equation of the conic through the 4 points 12.67, 34.67, 12.45, and 23.56; and by making the conic pass through 1 of the remaining 4 of the 8 points, I succeeded in finding the value

$$\lambda = \frac{(6 - 2)(7 - 8)}{(2 - 6)(3 - 4)},$$

so that the conic in question passes through 5 of the 8 points, and is therefore by the theorem the conic through the 8 points. But as thus written down the equation contains the extraneous factor $2 - 6$, as appears at once by the observation that the left-hand side on writing therein $6 = 2$ ($\alpha_6 = \alpha_2$) becomes identically $= 0$; the value in fact is

$$\begin{aligned} & - (2 - 8)[x - (2 + 7)y + 27z](23 - 34 + 45 - 52)[x - (1 + 2)y + 12z] \\ & + (2 - 8)[x - (1 + 2)y + 12z](23 - 34 + 45 - 52)[x - (2 + 7)y + 27z], \end{aligned}$$

which is $= 0$; there is consequently the factor $2 - 6$ to be rejected, and throwing this out the equation assumes a symmetrical form in regard to the 8 symbols 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6, 7, 8. The coefficient of x^2 is very easily found to be

$$= (2 - 6)(12 - 23 + 34 - 45 + 56 - 67 + 78 - 81),$$

and similarly that of z^2 to be

$$\begin{aligned} & = (2 - 6)(123456 - 234567 + 345678 - 456781 \\ & + 567812 - 678123 + 781234 - 812345) : \end{aligned}$$

those of the other terms are somewhat more difficult to calculate; but the final result, throwing out the factor $(2 - 6)$, and introducing an abbreviated notation

$$\Sigma 12 = (12 - 23 + 34 - 45 + 56 - 67 + 78 - 81),$$

and the like in other cases, is found to be

$$\begin{aligned}
 & x^2 \Sigma 12 \\
 & + y^2 [\Sigma 12(4+5)(6+7) - \tfrac{1}{2} \Sigma 1256] \\
 & + z^2 \Sigma 123456 \\
 & - yz \Sigma 16(234+235+245+345) \\
 & + zx [\Sigma 1234 + \tfrac{1}{2} \Sigma 1256] \\
 & - xy \Sigma 12(4+5+6+7) = 0,
 \end{aligned}$$

where it is to be observed that $\Sigma 1256$ consists of 4 distinct terms each twice repeated: $\frac{1}{2} \Sigma 1256$ consists therefore of these 4 terms; and in the coefficient of y^2 they destroy 4 of the 32 terms of $\Sigma 12(4+5)(6+7)$ so that the coefficient of y^2 contains $32-4=28$ terms. In the coefficient of zx there is no destruction, and this contains therefore $12+4=16$ terms.

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Review. Tables de Logarithmes vulgaires a dix decimales construites d'apres un nouveau mode par S. Pineto, approuvees par l'Academie des Sciences de S. Petersbourg. S. Petersbourg, 1871.

[From the Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 375-376.]

THE tables occupy 56 pages—the principal one being a table in 44 pages, the 22 left-hand pages containing the 10 figure logarithms of the numbers from 1,000,000 to 1,010,999, and the 22 right-hand pages the proportional parts .01, .02, . . . , .99 of the differences. A like table 100,000 to 999,999 would occupy 3600 pages. By means of an auxiliary table of 3 pages, and of a slight increase of the numerical calculation, the table of 44 pages does the work of the table of 3600 pages. To explain how this is: the auxiliary table gives for any number A the initial four digits of which are equal to or exceed 1011, a multiplier M , such that in the product MA the initial four digits are between 1000 and 1011; this multiplier M contains only 1, 2 or 3 figures, and when there are 3 figures, then in general either the middle figure is 0, or two of the figures are equal; the table gives also $\log \frac{1}{M}$ to 12 decimals; and there is a third column, as will be explained. Hence A being as above, the auxiliary table gives M , we form the product MA , obtain the logarithm thereof from the principal table, and adding thereto $\log \frac{1}{M}$, we have the required $\log A$. Conversely, when there is given a logarithm B the first five digits in the mantissa of which are not included between 00000 and 00474 (being the limits of the first five digits of the logarithms in the principal table), the auxiliary table by means of its third column gives M ; adding $\log \frac{1}{M}$ to B , we have a logarithm included in the limits of

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the principal table, and seeking for the corresponding number, this is $= \frac{1}{M}$ number having B for its logarithm: that is, the required number is $= M$ times the number obtained as above. Of course as regards the principal Table, the proportional parts are employed in the usual manner; the tabulation of them to hundredths (instead of tenths) facilitates the interpolation; for better securing the accuracy of the last figure, directions are given in regard to the 11th and 12th figures. An example

of the determination of a logarithm is as follows:

$$\begin{array}{r}
 \pi = 31415926536, \\
 M\pi = 100.53096\,49152, \\
 \log \frac{1}{M} = 8.49485\,00216.80 - 10, \\
 \log = 2.00229\,95705.75, \\
 \begin{array}{r}
 64 \quad 276.80, \\
 91 \quad 39.31, \\
 52 \quad 22, \\
 \hline
 \log \pi = 0.49714\,98726.88
 \end{array}
 \end{array}$$

(correct value of last two figures = 94).

The labour saved by the small bulk of the Tables goes far to balance that occasioned by the additional steps in the calculation.

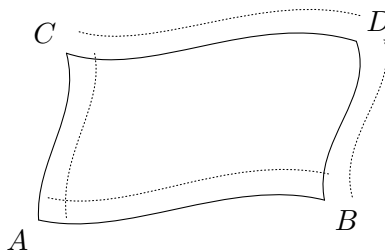
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On the Surfaces Divisible into Squares by their Curves of Curvature.

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. IV. (1871–1873), pp. 8, 9. Read December 14, 1871.]

GEOMETRICALLY, the question is as follows:—Consider any two curves of curvature AB , CD of one set, and any two AC , BD of the other set, as shown by the continuous lines of the figure: drawing the consecutive curves as shown by dotted lines, the curve consecutive to AB at an arbitrary (infinitesimal) distance from AB , the other three curves may be drawn at such distances that the elements at A , B , and C shall be each of them a square; but this being so, the element at D will not be in general a square, and it is only for certain surfaces that it is so. But if (whatever the curves of curvature AB , CD , AD , BC may be) the element at D is a square, then it is clear that the whole surface can be, by means of its curves of curvature, divided into infinitesimal squares.



Analytically, if for a given surface the equations of its curves of curvature are expressed in the form $h = f(x, y, z)$, $k = \phi(x, y, z)$; then the coordinates x, y, z can

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be expressed each of them as a function of the parameters h, k , and we have for the element of distance between two consecutive points on the surface

$$dx^2 + dy^2 + dz^2 = A dh^2 + C dk^2,$$

where A, C are in general each of them a function of h and k . The condition for the divisibility into squares is that the quotient $A \div C$ shall be of the form function $h \div$ function k .

It was shown by M. Bertrand that, in a triple system of orthotomic isothermal surfaces, each surface possesses the property in question of divisibility into squares by means of its curves of curvature. But in such a triple system, each surface of the system is necessarily a quadric; so that the theorem comes to this, that a quadric surface is, by means of its curves of curvature, divisible into squares. The analytical verification is at once effected: taking the equation of the surface to be

$$\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c} = 1,$$

then the expressions for the coordinates in terms of the parameters h, k of a curve of curvature are

$$\begin{aligned} x^2 &= \frac{a(a+h)(a+k)}{(a-b)(a-c)}, \\ y^2 &= \frac{b(b+h)(b+k)}{(b-c)(b-a)}, \\ z^2 &= \frac{c(c+h)(c+k)}{(c-a)(c-b)}, \end{aligned}$$

and we have

$$4(dx^2 + dy^2 + dz^2) = (h-k)^2 \left\{ \frac{h dh^2}{(a+h)(b+h)(c+h)} - \frac{k dk^2}{(a+k)(b+k)(c+k)} \right\},$$

so that $A \div C$ is of the required form.

But there is nothing to show that the property is confined to quadric surfaces; and the question of the determination of the surfaces possessing the property appears to be one of considerable difficulty, and which has not hitherto been examined.

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On the Surfaces each the Locus of the Vertex of a Cone which Passes through m Given Points and Touches $6 - m$ Given Lines.

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. IV. (1871–1873), pp. 11–47. Read January 11, 1872.]

I CONSIDER the surfaces, each of them the locus of the vertex of a (quadri-)cone which passes through m given points and touches $6 - m$ given lines; viz. calling the given points $a, b, c, \dots$ and the given lines $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \dots$, the surfaces in question are:

surface	order
$abcdef$	4
$abcde\alpha$	8
$abcd\alpha\beta$	16
$abc\alpha\beta\gamma$	24
$ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$	24
$a\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon$	14
$\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$	8

I remark that the orders of these several surfaces are in effect determined by the investigations of M. Chasles in regard to the conics in space which satisfy seven conditions. The surface $abcdef$ was long ago considered by M. Chasles, and it is treated of in my “Memoir on Quartic Surfaces,” [445], and in the same Memoir the surface $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$ is also referred to: these two surfaces, and also the surfaces

$a\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon$ and $ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$ are considered by Dr Hierholzer¹ in his excellent paper “Ueber Kegelschnitte im Raume,” *Math. Annalen*, t. II. (1870), pp. 563–586, and to him are due the equations given in the sequel for the surfaces $abcdef$ and $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$: the researches of the present Memoir are in fact a continuation and development of those in the Memoir last referred to.

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1. We have on the before-mentioned surfaces respectively certain simple or multiple points, right lines, and curves, as shown in the following Table:

¹I was grieved to hear of Dr Hierholzer's death last autumn, at Carlsruhe, at the early age of 30.

	$abcdef, 4$	$abcde\alpha, 8$	$abcd\alpha\beta, 16$	$abc\alpha\beta\gamma, 24$	$ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta, 24$	$a\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon, 14$	$\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta, 8$
Points a	$6 \times (2)$	$5 \times (4)$	$4 \times (8)$	$3 \times (8)$	$2 \times (4)$	$1 \times (2)$	0
ab	$15 \times (1), C$	$10 \times (2), C$	$6 \times (4), C$	$3 \times (4), C$	$1 \times (2), C$	0	0
α	0	$1 \times (2), C$	$2 \times (4), C$	$3 \times (8), C$	$4 \times (8), C$	$5 \times (4), C$	$6 \times (2), C$
$[ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma]$	0	0	0	$6 \times (4), P$	${}^33 \times (2+2), L$	0	0
$[\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta]$	0	0	0	0	$2 \times (8), P$	$10 \times (2), L$	$30 \times (1), L$
$[ab, cd, \alpha, \beta]$	0	0	$6 \times (2), P$	0	0	0	0
abc, def	$10 \times (1), P$	0	0	0	0	0	0
abc, de, α	0	${}^410 \times (1), P$	0	0	0	0	0
abc, α, β	0	0	${}^24 \times (2+2), P$	$3 \times (4), P$	0	0	0
Cubic $abcdef$	$1 \times (1), C$	0	0	0	0	0	0
Quadriquadric $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon\zeta$	0	0	0	0	0	0	${}^110 \times (1), L$
Excuboquartic $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon, a$	0	0	0	0	0	${}^410 \times (1), L$	0

1. Tangent plane along line is plane abc .
2. Tacnodal line, each sheet touched along line by plane abc .
3. Tacnodal line, each sheet of surface touched along line by hyperboloid $\alpha\beta\gamma$.
4. Surface touched along line by hyperboloid $\alpha\beta\gamma$.

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2. In the Table, the upper margin refers to the surfaces, and the left-hand margin to the points, lines, and curves situate on these surfaces respectively; the body of the Table showing the number, and in () the multiplicity, of these points, lines, and curves in regard to the several surfaces respectively. Thus, points a ; for the surface $abcdef$, $6 \times (2)$, there are 6 such points, each of them a 2-conical (ordinary conical) point on the surface: so $abcdea$, $5 \times (4)$, there are 5 such points, each a 4-conical point on the surface (viz. instead of the tangent plane there is a quartic cone); and so on. Similarly, lines ab (viz. these are the lines joining two points a, b); for the surface $abcdef$, $15 \times (1)$, there are 15 such lines, each a simple line on the surface; surface $abcdea$, $10 \times (2)$, there are 10 such lines, each a double (ordinary nodal) line on the surface; and so on. We have in two places the multiplicity $(2+2)$, which refers to a tacnodal line, as presently explained. The corner letters C, P, L denote respectively proper cone, plane-pair, and line-pair, as afterwards explained.

3. The lines and curves referred to in the left-hand margin are:

1. ab , line joining the points a and b .
2. α , line α .
3. $[ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma]$, pair of lines meeting each of the four lines, or say the tractors of the four lines $ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma$. As regards the surface $ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$, the multiplicity is given as $(2+2)$, viz. the line is (not an ordinary nodal, but) a tacnodal line, each sheet touching along the whole line the hyperboloid $\alpha\beta\gamma$.
4. $[\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta]$, tractors of the four lines $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$.
5. $[ab, cd, \alpha, \beta]$ tractors of the four lines ab, cd, α, β .
6. abc, def , line of intersection of the planes abc and def .
7. abc, de, α , line in the plane abc joining the intersections of this plane by the lines de and α respectively.
8. abc, α, β , line in the plane abc joining the intersections of this plane by the lines α and β respectively. As regards the surface $abcd\alpha\beta$, the multiplicity is given as $(2+2)$, viz. each line is (not an ordinary nodal, but) a tacnodal line, each sheet touching along the whole line the plane abc .
9. Cubic $abcdef$, cubic curve through the six points a, b, c, d, e, f , common intersection of the cones each having its vertex at one of the points and passing through the other five.
10. Quadriquadric $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon\zeta$, intersection of the quadric surfaces $\alpha\beta\gamma$ and $\delta\epsilon\zeta$ that is, the quadric surfaces through the lines α, β, γ and δ, ϵ, ζ respectively.
11. Excuboquartic $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon, a$, quartic curve generated as follows: viz. taking any line whatever which meets the lines α, β, γ (or say any generating line of the quadric $\alpha\beta\gamma$), the plane through this line and the point a meets the lines δ, ϵ in two points respectively; and the line joining these meets the generating line in a point having for its locus the excuboquartic curve in question (theory further considered in the sequel).

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Special forms of (Quadri-)Cones.

4. We have to consider the special forms of (quadri-)cones; these are: 1°. The sharp-cone, or plane-pair; that is, a pair of two planes, intersecting in a line called the axis, the vertex being in this case an indeterminate point on the axis. Observe that a plane-pair passes through a given point when either of its planes passes through such point; it touches a given line when its axis meets the given line. 2°. The flat-cone, or line-pair; viz. this is a pair of intersecting lines, their point of intersection being the vertex of the line-pair, and the plane of the two lines being the diametral of the line-pair. Observe that the line-pair passes through a given point when its diametral passes through such point; it touches a given line when either of its lines meets the given line. 3°. There is a third kind, the line-pair-plane; viz. the two planes of the plane-pair may come to coincide, retaining, however, a definite line of intersection, or axis: or again, the two lines of a line-pair may come to coincide, retaining a definite plane or diametral; that is, in either case we have a plane passing through a line; and which is to be considered indifferently as two coincident planes intersecting in the line, or as two coincident lines lying in the plane. But there is not, in the present Memoir, any occasion to consider this third kind of special cone.

The letters C, P, L in the Table denote that the cone is a (proper) cone, plane-pair, or line-pair, as the case may be.

Singular Lines and Curves on the Surfaces.

5. We may establish *a priori* the existence, and even to some extent the multiplicity, of the several lines and curves on the surfaces $abcdef, \dots, \alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$. Thus:

1°. Lines ab : take for the vertex of the cone a point at pleasure on the line ab ; the cone passing through b will *ipso facto* pass through a ; and the conditions are thus that the cone shall pass through b and satisfy four other conditions—in all, five conditions: and there is thus a cone with the point in question as vertex; that is, the line ab is situate on the surface. Moreover, for the surfaces $abcdef, abcde\alpha, abcd\alpha\beta, abca\beta\gamma, ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$ respectively, for a given position of the vertex on the line ab , the number of cones is 1, 2, 4, 4, 2 respectively: and these are the multiplicities of the line ab on the several surfaces respectively.

2°. Lines α : take for the vertex of the cone a point at pleasure on the line α ; then the cone *ipso facto* touches the line α , and there are only five other conditions to be satisfied; that is, we have a cone with the vertex in question; or the line α is situate on the surface. Moreover, for the surfaces $abcde\alpha, abcd\alpha\beta, abca\beta\gamma, ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta, a\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon, \alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$ respectively, the number of cones is 1, 2, 4, 4, 2, 1 respectively: and it may be seen that the multiplicities of the line α are the doubles of these numbers, or are = 2, 4, 8, 8, 4, 2 for the several surfaces respectively.

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3°. Lines $[ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma]$: taking the vertex in one of these tractors, the cone cannot be a proper cone, but (if it exist) it must be either a line-pair having the tractor for one of its lines, or else a plane-pair having the tractor for its axis. The two cases are:

Surface $abca\beta\gamma$. Cone is a plane-pair, the two planes intersecting in the tractor, and passing, the one of them through the points a, b , the other through the point c . The vertex being an indeterminate point on the tractor, the tractor is situate on the surface.

Surface $aba\beta\gamma\delta$. Cone is a line-pair, one line being the tractor, the other a line drawn in the plane of the tractor and ab to meet δ , and which meets the tractor in an arbitrary point thereof: the tractor is thus a line on the surface.

4°. Lines $[\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta]$: taking the vertex in one of these tractors, then, as in the last case, the cone is either a line-pair having the tractor for one of its lines or a plane-pair having the tractor for its axis. The three cases are:

Surface $aba\beta\gamma\delta$. Cone is a plane-pair, the two planes intersecting in the tractor and passing through the points a, b respectively.

Surface $\alpha\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon$. Cone is a line-pair, one line being the tractor, the other a line in the plane of the tractor and α , meeting the line ϵ and meeting the tractor in an indeterminate point.

Surface $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$. Cone is a line-pair, one line being the tractor, the other a line drawn from an indeterminate point of the tractor to meet the lines ϵ and ζ .

5°. Lines $[ab, cd, \alpha, \beta]$. Cone is a plane-pair, the two planes intersecting in the tractor, and passing through the points a, b and the points c, d respectively.

6°. Line abc, def . Cone is a plane-pair, consisting of the two planes abc and def .

7°. Line abc, de, α . Cone is a plane-pair, the two planes intersecting in the line; one plane being abc , the other a plane through the line de .

8°. Line abc, α, β . There are two cases:

Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$. Cone is a plane-pair, the two planes intersecting in the line; the one being abc , and the other passing through the point d .

Surface $abc\alpha\beta\gamma$. Cone is a line-pair; one line being abc, α, β , the other a line in the plane abc meeting the line δ , and meeting the line abc, α, β in an indeterminate point.

9°. Cubic $abcdef$. Each point of the cubic is the vertex of a proper cone passing through the cubic, and therefore through the six points; that is, the cubic is a line on the surface $abcdef$.

10°. Quadriquadric $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon\zeta$. Cone is a line-pair; viz. it is composed of the lines drawn from any point of the curve, one of them to meet the lines α, β, γ , and the other to meet the lines δ, ϵ, ζ .

11°. Excuboquartic $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon, a$. Cone is a line-pair; the two lines being, one of them a line at pleasure meeting α, β, γ , the other the line which, in the plane of the other line and the point a , meets the lines δ, ϵ .

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Mode of obtaining the several Equations: Notations and Formulas.

6. The equations of the several surfaces are obtained by taking as centre of projection an assumed position of the vertex, and projecting everything upon an arbitrary plane; the projections of the given points and lines are points and lines in the arbitrary plane, and the section of the cone by this plane is a conic; the equation of the surface is thus obtained as the condition that there shall be a conic passing through m given points and touching $6 - m$ given lines.

7. We take as current coordinates (X, Y, Z, W) , or when plane-coordinates are employed $(\xi, \eta, \zeta, \omega)$: the coordinates of the vertex are throughout represented by (x, y, z, w) ; but in explanations &c., these are also used as current coordinates. The plane of projection is taken to be $W = 0$. The coordinates of the given points a , &c., are taken to be (x_a, y_a, z_a, w_a) , &c. There is no confusion occasioned by so doing, and I retain the ordinary letters (a, b, c, f, g, h) for the six coordinates of a line, it being understood that these letters so used have no reference whatever to the given points a, b , &c.; viz. the coordinates of the given lines α , &c., are $(a_\alpha, b_\alpha, c_\alpha, f_\alpha, g_\alpha, h_\alpha)$, &c.; there is sometimes occasion to consider the coordinates of other lines ab , &c., but the notation will always be explained.

8. I write l, m, n, p, q, r for the coordinates of the line joining the vertex (x, y, z, w) with a point (x', y', z', w') ; viz.

$$\begin{aligned} l &= yz' - y'z, & p &= xw' - x'w, & m &= zx' - z'x, & q &= yw' - y'w, \\ n &= xy' - x'y, & r &= zw' - z'w, \end{aligned}$$

($l_a = yz_a - y_az$, &c., this being explained when necessary); and also

$$\begin{aligned} P &= hy - gz + aw, \\ Q &= -hx + fz + bw, \\ R &= gx - fy + cw, \\ S &= -ax - by - cz, \end{aligned}$$

($P_\alpha = h_\alpha y - g_\alpha z + a_\alpha w$, &c., this being explained when necessary).

This being so, then projecting from the vertex (x, y, z, w) , say on the plane $W = 0$, the x, y, z coordinates of the projection of a point a are as $p_a : q_a : r_a$ ($p_a = xw_a - x_a w$, &c.); and the equation of the projection of a line α is

$$P_\alpha X + Q_\alpha Y + R_\alpha Z = 0$$

($P_\alpha = h_\alpha y - g_\alpha z + a_\alpha w$, &c.). We thus have, in the projection on the plane $W = 0$, the m points and $6 - m$ lines situate in and touched by the conic.

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The following notations and formulae are convenient:

9. $\mathbf{p}_{abc} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the points a, b, c ; viz.

$$\mathbf{p}_{abc} = \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ x_b & y_b & z_b & w_b \\ x_c & y_c & z_c & w_c \end{vmatrix}.$$

Of course $\mathbf{p}_{bac} = -\mathbf{p}_{abc}$, &c. Observe that here, and in the notations which follow, the letter $\mathbf{p}$ is used as referring to the coordinates (x, y, z, w) , and that the index of $\mathbf{p}$ ($= 1$ when no index is expressed) shows the degree in these coordinates.

10. $\mathbf{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the point a and the line α ; viz. $\mathbf{p}_{a\alpha}$ is the foregoing determinant, if for a moment b, c are any two points on the line α ; or, what is the same thing,

$$\mathbf{p}_{a\alpha} = P_\alpha x_a + Q_\alpha y_a + R_\alpha z_a + S_\alpha w_a,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} P_\alpha &= hx_a - gz_a + aw_a, \\ Q_\alpha &= -hx_a + fz_a + bw_a, \\ R_\alpha &= gx_a - fy_a + cw_a, \\ S_\alpha &= -ax_a - by_a - cz_a. \end{aligned}$$

and (a, b, c, f, g, h) are the coordinates of the line α : observe that $\mathbf{p}_{a\alpha} = \mathbf{p}_{\alpha a}$.

11. $\mathbf{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = 0$ is the equation of the quadric surface through the lines α, β, γ ; viz. we have

$$\begin{aligned} \mathbf{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 &= (agh)x^2 + (bhf)y^2 + (cfg)z^2 + (abc)w^2 \\ &\quad + [(abg) - (cah)]xw + [(bch) - (abf)]yw + [(caf) - (bcg)]zw \\ &\quad + [(bcf) + (ach)]yz + [(cag) + (bfh)]zx + [(abh) + (bgh)]xy, \end{aligned}$$

where

$$agh = \begin{vmatrix} a_\alpha & g_\alpha & h_\alpha \\ a_\beta & g_\beta & h_\beta \\ a_\gamma & g_\gamma & h_\gamma \end{vmatrix},$$

&c. $(a_\alpha, b_\alpha, c_\alpha, f_\alpha, g_\alpha, h_\alpha)$, $(a_\beta, \dots)$, $(a_\gamma, \dots)$ being the coordinates of the given lines α, β, γ . Observe that $\mathbf{p}_{\beta\alpha\gamma}^2 = -\mathbf{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$, &c.

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12. It is to be noticed that, writing

$$P = hy - gz + aw, \quad Q = -hx + fz + bw, \quad R = gx - fy + cw, \quad S = -ax - by - cz,$$

viz. $P_\alpha = h_\alpha y - g_\alpha z + a_\alpha w$, &c., then that we have identically

$$\begin{vmatrix} \lambda & \mu & \nu & \rho \\ P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha & S_\alpha \\ P_\beta & Q_\beta & R_\beta & S_\beta \\ P_\gamma & Q_\gamma & R_\gamma & S_\gamma \end{vmatrix} = -(\lambda x + \mu y + \nu z + \rho w) \mathbf{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2,$$

and further that we have identically

$$-\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = L_{\alpha\beta}P_{\gamma} + M_{\alpha\beta}Q_{\gamma} + N_{\alpha\beta}R_{\gamma} + \Omega_{\alpha\beta}S_{\gamma},$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} L &= (af' - a'f)x + (bf' - b'f)y + (cf' - c'f)z - (bc' - b'c)w, \\ M &= (ag' - a'g)x + (bg' - b'g)y + (cg' - c'g)z - (ca' - c'a)w, \\ N &= (ah' - a'h)x + (bh' - b'h)y + (ch' - c'h)z - (ab' - a'b)w, \\ \Omega &= (gh' - g'h)x + (hf' - h'f)y + (fg' - f'g)z \\ &\quad + (af' - a'f + bg' - b'g + ch' - c'h)w; \end{aligned}$$

and $L_{\alpha\beta}$, &c. are the values of L , &c. on substituting therein $(a_{\alpha}, \dots)$ and $(a_{\beta}, \dots)$ for the unaccented and accented letters respectively.

13. Observe that we have

$$\begin{aligned} L + (a'f + b'g + c'h)x &= -c'Q + b'R - f'S, \\ M + (a'f + b'g + c'h)y &= c'P - a'R - g'S, \\ N + (a'f + b'g + c'h)z &= -b'P + a'Q - h'S, \\ \Omega + (a'f + b'g + c'h)w &= f'P + g'Q + h'R, \end{aligned}$$

and similarly

$$\begin{aligned} -L + (af' + bg' + ch')x &= -cQ' + bR' - fS', \\ -M + (af' + bg' + ch')y &= cP' - aR' - gS', \\ -N + (af' + bg' + ch')z &= -bP' + aQ' - hS', \\ -\Omega + (af' + bg' + ch')w &= fP' + gQ' + hR'. \end{aligned}$$

whence also

$$\begin{aligned} h'M - g'N + a'\Omega &= -(a'f + b'g + c'h)P', \\ -h'L + f'N + b'\Omega &= -(a'f + b'g + c'h)Q', \\ g'L - f'M + c'\Omega &= -(a'f + b'g + c'h)R', \\ -a'L - b'M - c'N &= -(a'f + b'g + c'h)S', \end{aligned}$$

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and

$$\begin{aligned} hM - gN + a\Omega &= (af' + bg' + ch')P, \\ -hL + fN + b\Omega &= (af' + bg' + ch')Q, \\ gL - fM + c\Omega &= (af' + bg' + ch')R, \\ -aL - bM - cN &= (af' + bg' + ch')S. \end{aligned}$$

14. $\mathfrak{p}_{a.\alpha\beta.\gamma\delta}^3 = 0$ is the equation of the cubic surface through the lines $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ and $a\alpha\beta$, $a\gamma\delta$ (viz. $a\alpha\beta$ is the line from a to meet α, β , and so $a\gamma\delta$ is the line from a to meet γ, δ). Observe that the conditions which determine this cubic surface thus are that the cubic shall pass through

a ; the points of $a\alpha\beta$ on α and β respectively, 3 other points on α , 3 on β ,
and 1 on $a\alpha\beta$;

also the points of $a\gamma\delta$ on γ and δ respectively, 3 other points on γ , 3 on δ , and 1 on $a\gamma\delta$; in all, $1 + 9 + 9 = 19$ points; viz. the conditions completely determine the surface.

15. We have

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a.\alpha\beta.\gamma\delta}^3 = \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ L_{\alpha\beta} & M_{\alpha\beta} & N_{\alpha\beta} & \Omega_{\alpha\beta} \\ L_{\gamma\delta} & M_{\gamma\delta} & N_{\gamma\delta} & \Omega_{\gamma\delta} \end{vmatrix},$$

viz. this determinant, equated to zero, gives the equation of the surface.

To prove this, take as before the unaccented letters (a, b, c, f, g, h) to refer to the line α , and the letters with one, two, and three accents to refer to the lines β, γ, δ respectively; write also L, M, N, Ω and L', M', N', Ω' for $L_{\alpha\beta}$, &c., and $L_{\gamma\delta}$, &c., respectively. Referring to the foregoing expressions for L, M, N, Ω , and observing that for a point on the line α , the values of P, Q, R, S are each $= 0$, then for such a point we have

$$L + (a'f + b'g + c'h)x = 0, \quad \&c.,$$

that is, $L : M : N : \Omega = x : y : z : w$, and these values satisfy the equation of the surface, which is thus a surface passing through the line α ; and similarly it passes through the lines β, γ, δ .

To show that the surface passes through the line $a\alpha\beta$, take the coordinates of the point a to be $0, 0, 0, 1$; then the line $a\alpha\beta$ is given as the intersection of the planes $ax + by + cz = 0$ and $a'x + b'y + c'z = 0$, that is, $S = 0$ and $S' = 0$. And the equation of the surface, writing therein $x_a, y_a, z_a, w_a = 0, 0, 0, 1$, becomes

$$\begin{vmatrix} x & y & z \\ L & M & N \\ L' & M' & N' \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

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or, as this may be written,

$$\begin{vmatrix} S & S' & z \\ aL + bM + cN & a'L + b'M + c'N & N \\ aL' + bM' + cN' & a'L' + b'M' + c'N' & N' \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

For a point on the line $a\alpha\beta$, this is

$$\begin{vmatrix} aL + bM + cN & a'L + b'M + c'N \\ aL' + bM' + cN' & a'L' + b'M' + c'N' \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

But in the equations

$$-a'L - b'M - c'N = -(a'f + b'g + c'h)S', \quad -aL - bM - cN = (af' + bg' + ch')S,$$

writing $S = 0$ and $S' = 0$, we have $aL + bM + cN = 0$ and $a'L + b'M + c'N = 0$, and the equation is satisfied; that is, the surface passes through the line $a\alpha\beta$, and similarly it passes through the line $a\gamma\delta$.

Surface $abcdef$.

16. The equation may be written

$$\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}\mathfrak{p}_{acf}\mathfrak{p}_{dbf} - \mathfrak{p}_{abf}\mathfrak{p}_{cdf}\mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe} = 0,$$

where $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the points a, b, e ; and the like for the other symbols. The form is one out of 45 like forms, depending on the partitionment

$$\left. \begin{matrix} ab.cd \\ ac.db \\ ad.bc \end{matrix} \right\} (ef),$$

of the six letters.

17. Investigation. In the projection, the six points (p_a, q_a, r_a) are situate on a conic; the condition for this is

$$\begin{vmatrix} p^2 & q^2 & r^2 & qr & rp & pq \end{vmatrix}_{a,b,c,d,e,f} = 0,$$

where the left-hand side represents the determinant obtained by writing successively (p_a, q_a, r_a) , &c., for (p, q, r) . The equation in question may be written

$$abe.cde.acf.dbf - abf.cdf.ace.dbe = 0;$$

where

$$abe = \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ p_b & q_b & r_b \\ p_e & q_e & r_e \end{vmatrix}, \quad \&c.$$

and substituting for $p_a, \dots$, their values, we have $abe = w^2 \mathfrak{p}_{abe}$, whence the foregoing result.

{Surface $abcdef$.}

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18. Singularities. The form of the equation shows at once that²

- (0) ³ The point a is a 2-conical point; in fact, for this point we have $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{acf} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{abf} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{ace} = 0$.
- (1) The line ab a simple line; in fact, for any point of this line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{abf} = 0$.
- (2) The line $abe.cdf$ a simple line; in fact, for any point of this line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{cdf} = 0$.
- (9) To show analytically that the cubic curve $abcdef$ is a line on the surface, observe that the equation of the surface is satisfied if we have simultaneously (λ being arbitrary)

$$\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{acf} - \lambda\mathfrak{p}_{abf}\mathfrak{p}_{ace} = 0, \quad \lambda\mathfrak{p}_{cde}\mathfrak{p}_{dbf} - \mathfrak{p}_{cdf}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe} = 0.$$

The first of these equations is a cone, vertex a , which passes through the points b, e, c, f , and which, if λ is properly determined, will pass through the point d ; the second is a cone, vertex d , which passes through the points b, e, c, f , and which, if λ is properly determined, will pass through the point a ; the two determinations of λ are

$$dabe.dacf - \lambda dabf.dace = 0, \quad \lambda acde.adbf - acdf.adbe = 0;$$

giving the same value of λ ; and the equations then represent cones, the first having a for its vertex, and passing through d, b, e, c, f ; the second having d for its vertex, and passing through a, b, e, c, f ; the two intersect in the line ad , and in the cubic curve $abcdef$, which is thus a curve on the surface.

Surface $abcde\alpha$.

19. The equation may be written

$$(\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2 - \mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2)^2 + 4\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}\mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}\mathfrak{p}_{abc}\mathfrak{p}_{dbc}\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha} = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2 + \mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2)^2 + 4\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}\mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}\mathfrak{p}_{bad}\mathfrak{p}_{cad}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha} = 0,$$

(the equivalence of the two depending on the identity

$$-\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2 + \mathfrak{p}_{abc}\mathfrak{p}_{dbc}\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha} - \mathfrak{p}_{bad}\mathfrak{p}_{cad}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha} = 0)$$

²Of course, as regards the present surface and the other surfaces for which the equation is given in an unsymmetrical form, the conclusion obtained in regard to any point or line of the surface applies to every point or line of the same kind. Thus ab being a simple line, we have also ad a simple line, although the equation, as written down, does not put this in evidence.

³The bracketed numbers refer to the lines of the Table.

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where, as before, $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the points a, b, e ; $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2 = 0$ the equation of the quadric surface through the lines α, ac, db ; and $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$ the equation of the plane through the point a and the line α .

The above forms are 2 out of 30 like forms, as appears by the partitionment

$$\begin{Bmatrix} ab, & cd \\ ac, & db \\ ad, & bc \end{Bmatrix} e\alpha.$$

20. Investigation. In the projection, the equation of the conic through the five points may be written

$$\left| \begin{array}{c} (X, Y, Z)^2 \\ (p, q, r)^2 \end{array} \right| = 0,$$

where the symbol denotes a determinant the last five lines of which are obtained by giving to (p, q, r) the suffixes a, b, c, d, e respectively. This is at once transformed into

$$abe.cde.ac\Delta.db\Delta - ace.dbe.ab\Delta.cd\Delta = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}.ac\Delta.db\Delta - \mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}.ab\Delta.cd\Delta = 0,$$

or say,

$$\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde}(A''X + B''Y + C''Z)(A'''X + B'''Y + C'''Z) - \mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}(AX + BY + CZ)(A'X + B'Y + C'Z),$$

where $\mathfrak{p}_{abe}$, &c. signify as before, and

$$AX + BY + CZ = \begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z \\ p_a & q_a & r_a \\ p_b & q_b & r_b \end{vmatrix},$$

and so for $A'X + B'Y + C'Z$, &c., the suffixes for A', B', C' being (c, d) , and those for A'', B'', C'' and A''', B''', C''' being (a, c) and (d, b) respectively.

21. Passing to the reciprocal equation, and making the conic touch the line α , we obtain the equation of the surface in the form

$$\begin{aligned} & \left\{ \mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde} \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix} - \mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe} \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A & B & C \\ A' & B' & C' \end{vmatrix} \right\}^2 \\ & + 4\mathfrak{p}_{ace}\mathfrak{p}_{dbe}\mathfrak{p}_{abe}\mathfrak{p}_{cde} \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A & B & C \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \end{vmatrix} \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A' & B' & C' \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

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where $P_\alpha = h_\alpha y - g_\alpha z + a_\alpha w = 0$; or in the equivalent form wherein we have in the first term + instead of -, and in the second term the determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A & B & C \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix}, \quad \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A' & B' & C' \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \end{vmatrix}.$$

22. {The question, in fact, is to find the reciprocal of the form

$$\lambda(ax + by + cz)(a'x + b'y + c'z) - \mu(a''x + b''y + c''z)(a'''x + b'''y + c'''z) = 0;$$

taking ξ, η, ζ for the reciprocal variables, the coefficient of ξ^2 is

$$\{\lambda(bc' + b'c) - \mu(b''c''' + b'''c'')\}^2 - (2\lambda bb' - 2\mu b''b''')(2\lambda cc' - 2\mu c''c'''),$$

viz. this is

$$\lambda^2(bc' - b'c)^2 + \mu^2(b''c''' - b'''c'')^2 + 2\lambda\mu\{2bb'c''c''' + 2b''b'''cc' - (bc' + b'c)(b''c''' + b'''c'')\},$$

or, as it may be written,

$$\{\lambda(bc' - b'c) \pm \mu(b''c''' - b'''c'')\}^2 + 2\lambda\mu \begin{pmatrix} 2bb'c''c''' + 2b''b'''cc' \\ \mp(bc' - b'c)(b''c''' - b'''c'') \\ -(bc' + b'c)(b''c''' + b'''c'') \end{pmatrix}.$$

Taking the upper signs, this is

$$\{\lambda(bc' - b'c) + \mu(b''c''' - b'''c'')\}^2 + 4\lambda\mu \begin{pmatrix} bb'c''c''' + b''b'''cc' \\ -bc'b''c''' - b'cb'''c'' \end{pmatrix};$$

viz. the term in $\lambda\mu$ is

$$= +4\lambda\mu(bc''' - b'''c)(b'c'' - b''c').$$

Taking the lower signs, it is

$$\{\lambda(bc' - b'c) - \mu(b''c''' - b'''c'')\}^2 + 4\lambda\mu \begin{pmatrix} bb'c''c''' + b''b'''cc' \\ -bc'b''c''' - b'cb'''c'' \end{pmatrix};$$

viz. the term in $\lambda\mu$ is

$$4\lambda\mu(bc'' - b''c)(b'c''' - b'''c');$$

and it is thence easy to infer the forms of the other coefficients, and to obtain the reciprocal equation in the two equivalent forms

$$\begin{aligned} & \left\{ \lambda \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a & b & c \\ a' & b' & c' \end{vmatrix} + \mu \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a'' & b'' & c'' \\ a''' & b''' & c''' \end{vmatrix} \right\}^2 \\ & + 4\lambda\mu \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a & b & c \\ a''' & b''' & c''' \end{vmatrix} \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a' & b' & c' \\ a'' & b'' & c'' \end{vmatrix} = 0, \\ & \left\{ \lambda \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a & b & c \\ a' & b' & c' \end{vmatrix} - \mu \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a'' & b'' & c'' \\ a''' & b''' & c''' \end{vmatrix} \right\}^2 \\ & + 4\lambda\mu \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a & b & c \\ a'' & b'' & c'' \end{vmatrix} \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a' & b' & c' \\ a''' & b''' & c''' \end{vmatrix} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

which are the required auxiliary formulae.}

{Surface $abcde\alpha$.}

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23. To reduce the foregoing result, we have

$$A, B, C = \begin{vmatrix} xw_a - wx_a & yw_a - wy_a & zw_a - wz_a \\ xw_b - wx_b & yw_b - wy_b & zw_b - wz_b \end{vmatrix}$$

proportional to the three determinants which contain w , of the set

$$\begin{array}{cccc} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a, \\ x_b & y_b & z_b & w_b \end{array} \quad \text{viz.} \quad A = w \begin{vmatrix} y & z & w \\ y_a & z_a & w_a \\ y_b & z_b & w_b \end{vmatrix},$$

and similarly A', B', C' are proportional to the three determinants which contain w , of the set

$$\begin{array}{cccc} x & y & z & w \\ x_c & y_c & z_c & w_c, \\ x_d & y_d & z_d & w_d \end{array} \quad \text{viz.} \quad A' = w \begin{vmatrix} y & z & w \\ y_c & z_c & w_c \\ y_d & z_d & w_d \end{vmatrix},$$

&c. Hence, omitting the factor w , and writing (a, b, c, f, g, h) and (a', b', c', f', g', h') for the coordinates of the lines ab and cd respectively, we have

$$\begin{aligned} A &= hy - gz + aw, & A' &= h'y - g'z + a'w, \\ B &= -hx + fz + bw, & B' &= -h'x + f'z + b'w, \\ C &= gx - fy + cw, & C' &= g'x - f'y + c'w; \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$BC' - B'C = \Omega x - Lw, \quad CA' - C'A = \Omega y - Mw, \quad AB' - A'B = \Omega z - Nw,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} L &= (af' - a'f)x + (bf' - b'f)y + (cf' - c'f)z - (bc' - b'c)w, \\ M &= (ag' - a'g)x + (bg' - b'g)y + (cg' - c'g)z - (ca' - c'a)w, \\ N &= (ah' - a'h)x + (bh' - b'h)y + (ch' - c'h)z - (ab' - a'b)w, \\ \Omega &= (gh' - g'h)x + (hf' - h'f)y + (fg' - f'g)z \\ &\quad - (af' - a'f + bg' - b'g + ch' - c'h)w; \end{aligned}$$

and consequently

$$\begin{aligned} \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A & B & C \\ A' & B' & C' \end{vmatrix} &= \Omega(xP_\alpha + yQ_\alpha + zR_\alpha) - w(LP_\alpha + MQ_\alpha + NR_\alpha) \\ &= -w(LP_\alpha + MQ_\alpha + NR_\alpha + \Omega S_\alpha), \end{aligned}$$

or omitting the factor $-w$, say it is $LP_\alpha + MQ_\alpha + NR_\alpha + \Omega S_\alpha$, viz. this is $= \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2$.
 $\{Surface abcde\alpha.\}$

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We have similarly

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix}$$

taken to be $= \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2$.

24. We have in like manner the other two determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A & B & C \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \end{vmatrix}, \quad \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ A' & B' & C' \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix}$$

taken to be $= \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.ac}^2$ and $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.cd.db}^2$ respectively. But we have

$$\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.ac}^2 = \mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{abc},$$

(viz. geometrically the hyperboloid through the lines α, ab, ac breaks up into the plane $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}$ through the line α and point a , and the plane $\mathfrak{p}_{abc}$ through the points a, b, c).

And similarly

$$\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.cd.db}^2 = -\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.dc.db}^2 = +\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.db.dc}^2 = \mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{dbc};$$

whence, substituting for the several determinants, we have the foregoing equation of the surface.

25. Singularities. The form of the equation shows that

- (0) The point a is a 4-conical point: in fact, for this point we have $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{ace} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2 = 0$.
- (1) The line ab is a double line: in fact, for any point of the line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{abc} = 0$.
- (2) The line α is a double line: in fact, for any point of the line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ac.db}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha} = 0$.
- (7) The line $abe.cd.\alpha$ is a simple line: in fact, for any point of the line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2 = 0$. Observe that, on writing in the equation $\mathfrak{p}_{abe} = 0$ the equation becomes $(\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha.ab.cd}^2)^2 = 0$; so that the surface along the line in question touches the plane $\mathfrak{p}_{abe}$.

Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.

26. The equation of the surface is

$$\text{Norm}\{\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{bcd}} - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{cda}} + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{dab}} - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{abc}}\} = 0,$$

where the norm is the product of 8 factors.

As before, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the point a and the line α ; and $\mathfrak{p}_{bcd} = 0$ the equation of the plane through the points b, c, d . The form is unique.

{Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.}

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27. Investigation. In the projection, the equation of the conic touching the projections of the lines α, β is

$$(P_\alpha X + Q_\alpha Y + R_\alpha Z)(P_\beta X + Q_\beta Y + R_\beta Z) + (AX + BY + CZ)^2 = 0,$$

where A, B, C are arbitrary coefficients. To make this pass through the projection of the point a , we must write $X : Y : Z = p_a : q_a : r_a$; viz. we thus have

$$\begin{aligned} P_\alpha X + Q_\alpha Y + R_\alpha Z &= P_\alpha p_a + Q_\alpha q_a + R_\alpha r_a \\ &= w_a(xP_\alpha + yQ_\alpha + zR_\alpha) - w(x_aP_\alpha + y_aQ_\alpha + z_aR_\alpha) \\ &= -w(x_aP_\alpha + y_aQ_\alpha + z_aR_\alpha + w_aS_\alpha) \\ &= -w\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}; \end{aligned}$$

and similarly

$$P_\beta X + Q_\beta Y + R_\beta Z = -w\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}.$$

We thus have

$$w\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} + Ap_a + Bq_a + Cr_a = 0.$$

Or, forming the like equations for the points b, c, d respectively and eliminating, the equation is

$$\begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} & p_a & q_a & r_a \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}} & p_b & q_b & r_b \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}} & p_c & q_c & r_c \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} & p_d & q_d & r_d \end{vmatrix} = 0;$$

which, substituting for (p_a, q_a, r_a) , &c., their values, viz. $p_a = xw_a - x_aw$, &c., is readily converted into

$$\begin{vmatrix} 0 & x & y & z & w \\ \sqrt{p_{a\alpha}p_{a\beta}} & x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ \sqrt{p_{b\alpha}p_{b\beta}} & x_b & y_b & z_b & w_b \\ \sqrt{p_{c\alpha}p_{c\beta}} & x_c & y_c & z_c & w_c \\ \sqrt{p_{d\alpha}p_{d\beta}} & x_d & y_d & z_d & w_d \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\sqrt{p_{a\alpha}p_{a\beta}p_{bcd}} - \sqrt{p_{b\alpha}p_{b\beta}p_{cda}} + \sqrt{p_{c\alpha}p_{c\beta}p_{dab}} - \sqrt{p_{d\alpha}p_{d\beta}p_{abc}} = 0;$$

viz. taking the norm, we have the form mentioned above.

28. Singularities. The equation shows that

- (0) The point a is an 8-conical point; in fact, for the point in question $p_{a\alpha} = 0$, $p_{a\beta} = 0$, $p_{cda} = 0$, $p_{dab} = 0$, $p_{abc} = 0$; each factor is of the form O^1 , and the norm is O^8 .

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- (1) The line ab is a 4-tuple line. To show this, observe in the first instance, that we may obtain the 8 factors of the norm by giving to the radical $\sqrt{p_{a\alpha}p_{a\beta}}$ the sign $+$, and to the other three radicals the signs $+$, $-$ at pleasure. For a point on the line in question, we have $p_{dab} = 0$, $p_{abc} = 0$; hence the norm is the product of the four equal factors

$$\sqrt{p_{a\alpha}p_{a\beta}p_{bcd}} - \sqrt{p_{b\alpha}p_{b\beta}p_{cda}},$$

and the other four equal factors obtained by writing herein $+$ instead of $-$.

Now for a point on the line ab , we may write for x, y, z, w the values $ux_a + vx_b$, $uy_a + vy_b$, $uz_a + vz_b$, $uw_a + vw_b$, where u, v are arbitrary coefficients. We have

$$\begin{aligned} p_{a\alpha} &= u.a\alpha\alpha + v.b\alpha\alpha = v.b\alpha\alpha = -v.ab\alpha, \\ p_{a\beta} &= v.ba\beta = -v.ab\beta, \\ p_{b\alpha} &= u.ab\alpha + v.bb\alpha = u.ab\alpha, \\ p_{b\beta} &= u.ab\beta, \\ p_{bcd} &= u.abcd + v.bbcd = u.abcd, \\ p_{cda} &= u.acda + v.bcda = v.bcda = -v.abcd, \end{aligned}$$

where $ab\alpha = 0$ is the condition that the points a, b and the line α may be in the same plane (or, what is the same thing, that the lines ab and α may intersect), viz. $ba\alpha = P_\alpha x_b + Q_\alpha y_b + R_\alpha z_b + S_\alpha w_b$. And similarly $abcd = 0$ is the condition that the four points a, b, c, d may be in a plane; viz. we have

$$abcd = \begin{vmatrix} x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ x_b & y_b & z_b & w_b \\ x_c & y_c & z_c & w_c \\ x_d & y_d & z_d & w_d \end{vmatrix}.$$

Substituting, we have

$$\sqrt{p_{a\alpha}p_{a\beta}p_{bcd}} \quad \text{and} \quad \sqrt{p_{b\alpha}p_{b\beta}p_{cda}},$$

each equal (save as to sign) to $uv\sqrt{ab\alpha.ab\beta.abcd}$; that is, the four equal factors of one set will vanish. The vanishing factors are of the form O^1 , and the norm is O^4 , that is, the line in question, ab , is a 4-tuple line.

(2) The line α is a 4-tuple line; in fact, for any point of the line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha} = 0$; each factor of the norm is therefore evanescent, of the form $O^{1/2}$, and the norm itself is thus $= O^4$.

29. (5) The line (ab, cd, α, β) is a double line. To show this, take $z = 0$, $w = 0$ as the equations of the line in question; then we have $h_\alpha = 0$, $h_\beta = 0$, $z_a w_b - z_b w_a = 0$; or say $w_a = \lambda z_a$, $w_b = \lambda z_b$: and $z_c w_d - z_d w_c = 0$; or say $w_c = \mu z_c$, $w_d = \mu z_d$ (λ and μ arbitrary coefficients). Putting for shortness

$$I_\alpha = (g_\alpha - \lambda a_\alpha)x - (f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha)y,$$

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viz. $I_\alpha = (g_\alpha - \lambda a_\alpha)x - (f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha)y$, &c., and writing $z = 0$, $w = 0$, we have

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta} = z_a^2 I_\alpha I_\beta, \quad \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta} = z_b^2 I_\alpha I_\beta, \quad \mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta} = z_c^2 J_\alpha J_\beta, \quad \mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta} = z_d^2 J_\alpha J_\beta;$$

and the factor of the norm (reverting to the expression thereof as a determinant) is

$$\begin{vmatrix} & x & y & . & . \\ \sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_a & y_a & z_a & \lambda z_a \\ \sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_b & y_b & z_b & \lambda z_b \\ \sqrt{J_\alpha J_\beta} & x_c & y_c & z_c & \mu z_c \\ \sqrt{J_\alpha J_\beta} & x_d & y_d & z_d & \mu z_d \end{vmatrix},$$

which vanishes. In fact, resolving the determinant into a set of products of the form $\pm 2.13.45$, where the single symbol denotes a term of the top line, and the binary symbols refer to the second and third lines, and the fourth and fifth lines respectively (denoting minors composed with the terms in these pairs of lines respectively); then each product will contain a term 14, 15, or 45, and the minor so designated (to whichever of the two pairs of lines it belongs) is $= 0$. The factor is thus evanescent, being, as it is easy to see, $= O^1$. There are two factors which vanish; viz. taking the first radical to be $+$, the second radical must be also $+$, but the third and fourth radicals may be either both $+$ or both $-$; the norm is thus $= O^2$, viz. the line (ab, cd, α, β) is a double line.

30. (8) The line abc, α, β is a double line. To prove this, take $w = 0$ for the equation of the plane abc , and $(z = 0, w = 0)$ for those of the line in question; we have $h_\alpha = 0$, $h_\beta = 0$, $w_a = 0$, $w_b = 0$, $w_c = 0$; and writing $I_\alpha = -g_\alpha x + f_\alpha y$, $I_\beta = -g_\beta x + f_\beta y$, then for $z = 0$, $w = 0$, the factor expressed as a determinant is

$$w_d \begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x & y & . \\ \sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_a & y_a & z_a \\ \sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_b & y_b & z_b \\ 0 & x_d & y_d & z_d \end{vmatrix},$$

which is consequently

$$w_d \begin{vmatrix} x & y & . \\ x_a & y_a & z_a \\ x_b & y_b & z_b \\ x_c & y_c & z_c \end{vmatrix}$$

and consequently vanishes, the form being O^1 . There are two such factors, viz. the radical $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}}$ may be either $+$ or $-$, hence the norm is $= O^2$.

31. But it is to be further shown that the line is tacnodal, each sheet of the surface being touched along the line by the plane $w = 0$: we have to show that the

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On the Surfaces each the Locus of the Vertex of a Cone which Passes through m Given Points and Touches $6 - m$ Given Lines.

The factor operated upon by

$$\Delta = X\delta_x + Y\delta_y + Z\delta_z + W\delta_w$$

reduces itself for $z = 0, w = 0$ to a multiple of W . Considering the factor in the form of a determinant, the result of the operation is

$$\begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z & W \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} & x_a & y_a & z_a \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}} & x_b & y_b & z_b \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}} & x_c & y_c & z_c \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} & x_d & y_d & z_d, w_d \end{vmatrix} + \begin{vmatrix} 0 & x & y & . & . \\ \Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} & x_a & y_a & z_a & . \\ \Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}} & x_b & y_b & z_b & . \\ \Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}} & x_c & y_c & z_c & . \\ \Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} & x_d & y_d & z_d & w_d \end{vmatrix}.$$

The first term is

$$\begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z & W \\ z_a\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_a & y_a & z_a \\ z_b\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_b & y_b & z_b \\ z_c\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} & x_c & y_c & z_c \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} & x_d & y_d & z_d, w_d \end{vmatrix},$$

where the first column may be replaced by

$$\begin{aligned} & -Z\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} \\ & \vdots \\ & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} - z_d\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} \end{aligned}$$

and the term in question thus becomes

$$\{w_d Z\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} + W(-z_d\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}})\} abc,$$

if for shortness

$$\begin{vmatrix} x_a & y_a & z_a \\ x_b & y_b & z_b \\ x_c & y_c & z_c \end{vmatrix} = abc.$$

As regards the second term, we have

$$\Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} = \frac{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\Delta\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\Delta\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}}{2\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}}},$$

which is

$$= \frac{I_\alpha\Delta\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta} + I_\beta\Delta\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}}.$$

But

$$\begin{aligned} \mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} &= x(-g_\alpha z_a) + y(f_\alpha z_a) + z(g_\alpha x_a - f_\alpha y_a) + w(a_\alpha x_a - b_\alpha y_a - c_\alpha z_a) \\ &= x_a(g_\alpha z - a_\alpha w) + y_a(-f_\alpha z - b_\alpha w) + z_a(-g_\alpha x + f_\alpha y - c_\alpha w); \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$\Delta\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = x_a(g_\alpha Z - a_\alpha W) + y_a(-f_\alpha Z - b_\alpha W) + z_a(-g_\alpha X + f_\alpha Y - c_\alpha W).$$

{Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.}

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With the like formula for $\Delta \mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}$; hence

$$\frac{I_\alpha \Delta \mathfrak{p}_{a\beta} + I_\beta \Delta \mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} = Ax_a + By_a + Cz_a,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} A &= \frac{1}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} \{I_\beta(g_\alpha Z - a_\alpha W) + I_\alpha(g_\beta Z - a_\beta W)\}, \\ B &= \frac{1}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} \{I_\beta(-f_\alpha Z - b_\alpha W) + I_\alpha(-f_\beta Z - b_\beta W)\}, \\ C &= \frac{1}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} \{I_\beta(-g_\alpha X + f_\alpha Y - c_\alpha W) + I_\alpha(-g_\beta X + f_\beta Y - c_\beta W)\}. \end{aligned}$$

The term in question is thus

$$\begin{vmatrix} 0 & x & y & \cdot & \cdot \\ Ax_a + By_a + Cz_a & x_a & y_a & z_a & \cdot \\ Ax_b + By_b + Cz_b & x_b & y_b & z_b & \cdot \\ Ax_c + By_c + Cz_c & x_c & y_c & z_c & \cdot \\ \Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} & x_d & y_d & z_d & w_d \end{vmatrix}.$$

Viz. replacing the first column by

$$\begin{aligned} &-Ax - By \\ &\vdots \\ &\Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} - Ax_d - By_d - Cz_d \end{aligned}$$

this is

$$= (Ax + By)w_d abc;$$

and we have

$$\begin{aligned} Ax + By &= \frac{1}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} [\{I_\beta(g_\alpha x - f_\alpha y) + I_\alpha(g_\beta x - f_\beta y)\}Z \\ &\quad + \{I_\beta(-a_\alpha x - b_\alpha y) + I_\alpha(-a_\beta x - b_\beta y)\}W] \\ &= \frac{1}{2\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} (-2I_\alpha I_\beta Z - MW), \end{aligned}$$

if for shortness

$$M = (-g_\beta x + f_\beta y)(a_\alpha x + b_\alpha y) + (-g_\alpha x + f_\alpha y)(a_\beta x + b_\beta y).$$

Viz. the whole term is

$$w_d \left\{ -\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} Z - \frac{\frac{1}{2}M}{\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} W \right\} abc.$$

Hence the first and second terms together are

$$= W \left\{ -z_d \sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta} + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{d\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{d\beta}} - \frac{\frac{1}{2}M}{\sqrt{I_\alpha I_\beta}} w_d \right\} abc;$$

viz. this is a multiple of W , which was the theorem to be proved.

{Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.}

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Surface $abc\alpha\beta\gamma$.

32. The equation is

$$\text{Norm} \begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}} \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}} \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\gamma}} \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

where the norm is a product of 16 factors, each of the order $\frac{3}{2}$. As before, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the point a and the line α ; viz. $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}$ has the value already mentioned.

33. *Investigation.* In the projection, the equation of the conic touching the projections of the lines α, β, γ is

$$A\sqrt{P_\alpha X + Q_\alpha Y + R_\alpha Z} + B\sqrt{P_\beta X + Q_\beta Y + R_\beta Z} + C\sqrt{P_\gamma X + Q_\gamma Y + R_\gamma Z} = 0;$$

and to make this pass through the projection of the point a , we must write herein $X : Y : Z = p_a : q_a : r_a$. As before, we have

$$\begin{aligned} P_\alpha X + Q_\alpha Y + R_\alpha Z &= w_a(xP_\alpha + yQ_\alpha + zR_\alpha) \\ &\quad - w(x_aP_\alpha + y_aQ_\alpha + z_aR_\alpha) \\ &= -w(x_aP_\alpha + y_aQ_\alpha + z_aR_\alpha + w_aS_\alpha) \\ &= -w\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}; \end{aligned}$$

and so for the other terms; the equation thus is

$$A\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}} + B\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}} + C\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}} = 0;$$

or forming the like equations in regard to the points b, c respectively, and eliminating, we have a determinant $= 0$, and then, taking the norm, we obtain the above-written equation of the surface.

34. *Singularities.* The equation of the surface shows that

- (0) The point a is 8-conical: for it $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = \mathfrak{p}_{a\beta} = \mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma} = 0$;
each factor is $O^{1/2}$, and the norm is O^8 .

- (1) The line ab is 4-tuple.

To prove this, observe that the sixteen factors are obtained by attributing at pleasure the signs $+$, $-$ to the radicals $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}}, \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}}, \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}}, \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\gamma}}$; hence there are four factors in which $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}}, \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}}$ have determinate signs, but in which we attribute to the radicals $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}}, \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\gamma}}$ the signs $+$ or $-$ at pleasure. It is to be shown that the four factors each vanish for a point on the line ab ; that is, on writing therein for x, y, z, w the values $ux_a + vx_b, uy_a + vy_b, \&c$.

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But we thus have, as before, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = -v \cdot ab\alpha$ and $\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = u \cdot ab\alpha$, with the like formulae with β and γ in place of α . The factor thus becomes

$$\sqrt{-uv} \begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{ab\alpha} & \sqrt{ab\alpha} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}} \\ \sqrt{ab\beta} & \sqrt{ab\beta} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}} \\ \sqrt{ab\gamma} & \sqrt{ab\gamma} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\gamma}} \end{vmatrix},$$

which vanishes, being $= O^1$; and the norm is thus $= O^4$, viz. the line is 4-tuple.

(2) The line α is 8-tuple: in fact, for a point on the line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0, \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = 0, \mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha} = 0$, whence each factor vanishes, being $= O^{1/2}$, and the norm is therefore O^8 .

(3) The line $(ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma)$ is 4-tuple: in fact, writing $z = 0, w = 0$ for the equations of the line, we have $h_\alpha = 0, h_\beta = 0, h_\gamma = 0$, and $z_a w_b - z_b w_a = 0$, or say $w_a = \lambda z_a, w_b = \lambda z_b$. Hence, writing

$$I = (g - \lambda a)x - (f + \lambda b)y,$$

viz. $I_\alpha = (g_\alpha - \lambda a_\alpha)x - (f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha)y$, &c., for $z = 0$, $w = 0$, we have $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = z_a I_\alpha$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = z_b I_\alpha$; and similarly $\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta} = z_a I_\beta$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta} = z_b I_\beta$, and $\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma} = z_a I_\gamma$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma} = z_b I_\gamma$. The factor thus is

$$\sqrt{z_a z_b} \begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{I_\alpha} & \sqrt{I_\alpha} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha}} \\ \sqrt{I_\beta} & \sqrt{I_\beta} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\beta}} \\ \sqrt{I_\gamma} & \sqrt{I_\gamma} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\gamma}} \end{vmatrix},$$

which vanishes, being $= O^1$; there are four such factors, or the norm is O^4 ; whence the line is 4-tuple.

(8) The line $abc.\alpha.\beta$ is a 4-tuple line. To prove it, take as before $w = 0$ for the equation of the plane abc , and $(z = 0, w = 0)$ for the equations of the line in question. We have $h_\alpha = 0$, $h_\beta = 0$, $w_a = 0$, $w_b = 0$, $w_c = 0$; whence (if $z = 0$, $w = 0$), writing for shortness $I = gx - fy$ (viz. $I_\alpha = g_\alpha x - f_\alpha y$, $I_\beta = g_\beta x - f_\beta y$), we have

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}, \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}, \mathfrak{p}_{c\alpha} = I_\alpha z_a, I_\alpha z_b, I_\alpha z_c,$$

and similarly

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}, \mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}, \mathfrak{p}_{c\beta} = I_\beta z_a, I_\beta z_b, I_\beta z_c.$$

The factor thus is

$$\begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{I_\alpha z_a} & \sqrt{I_\alpha z_b} & \sqrt{I_\alpha z_c} \\ \sqrt{I_\beta z_a} & \sqrt{I_\beta z_b} & \sqrt{I_\beta z_c} \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}} & \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{c\gamma}} \end{vmatrix},$$

which vanishes, being $= O^1$; and there are four such factors, obtained by giving to the radicals the signs $+$, $-$ at pleasure: hence the norm is $= O^4$.

{Surface $abc\alpha\beta\gamma$.}

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Surface $ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$.

35. The equation is

$$\text{Norm}\{\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}}\mathfrak{p}_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2 - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\delta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2\} = 0,$$

where the norm is the product of 8 factors each of the order 3. As before, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the point a and the line α ; viz. $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}$ has the value previously mentioned; and $\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 = 0$ is the equation of the quadric surface through the lines β, γ, δ .

36. *Investigation.* In the projection, taking ξ, η, ζ as current line-coordinates, the equation of the conic passing through the projections of the points a, b is

$$\sqrt{(p_a\xi + q_a\eta + r_a\zeta)(p_b\xi + q_b\eta + r_b\zeta)} + A\xi + B\eta + C\zeta = 0,$$

where A, B, C are arbitrary coefficients. To make this touch the projection of the line α , we must write $\xi : \eta : \zeta = P_\alpha : Q_\alpha : R_\alpha$; and then

$$\begin{aligned} p_a\xi + q_a\eta + r_a\zeta &= p_aP_\alpha + q_aQ_\alpha + r_aR_\alpha \\ &= w_a(xP_\alpha + yQ_\alpha + zR_\alpha) \\ &\quad - w(x_aP_\alpha + y_aQ_\alpha + z_aR_\alpha) \\ &= -w(x_aP_\alpha + y_aQ_\alpha + z_aR_\alpha + w_aS_\alpha) \\ &= -w\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}, \end{aligned}$$

and similarly

$$p_b\xi + q_b\eta + r_b\zeta = -w\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}.$$

Hence the equation is

$$w\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}} + AP_\alpha + BQ_\alpha + CR_\alpha = 0;$$

and forming the like equations for the lines β, γ, δ respectively, and eliminating, we have

$$\begin{vmatrix} \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}} & P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}} & P_\beta & Q_\beta & R_\beta \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}} & P_\gamma & Q_\gamma & R_\gamma \\ \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\delta}} & P_\delta & Q_\delta & R_\delta \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

which, throwing out a factor w , becomes the displayed equation above; or, taking the norm, we have the above-written equation.

37. *Singularities.* The equation shows that

$$(0) \quad \text{The point } a \text{ is a 4-conical point; for it } \mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = \mathfrak{p}_{a\beta} = \mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma} = \mathfrak{p}_{a\delta} = 0,$$

each factor is $= O^{1/2}$, and the norm is $= O^4$.

{Surface } ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta.

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(1) The line ab is a 2-tuple line. To prove this, we have for the coordinates of a point on the line in question $ux_a + vx_b$, $uy_a + vy_b$, &c.; the values of $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}$ become as before $-v \cdot ab\alpha$, $+u \cdot ab\alpha$, and similarly for $\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}$, &c.; so that, omitting the constant factor $\sqrt{-uv}$, the value of the factor is

$$ab\alpha \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - ab\beta \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 + ab\gamma \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2 - ab\delta \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2.$$

Taking (a, b, c, f, g, h) for the coordinates of the line ab , we have

$$ab\alpha = af_\alpha + bg_\alpha + ch_\alpha + fa_\alpha + gb_\alpha + hc_\alpha,$$

with the like expressions for $ab\beta$, &c.; and substituting for $\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2$, &c., their values, the factor is represented by the following coefficient table:

	x^2	y^2	z^2	w^2	xw	yw	zw	yz	zx	xy
a	$fagh$			fab	$fabg - fach$	$fbch$	$-fbcg$		$fcgh$	$fbgh$
b		$gbhf$		$gabc$	$-gach$	$gbch - gabf$	$gcaf$	$gchf$	$hafg$	$gahf$
c			$hcfg$	$habc$	$habg$	$-habf$	$hcaf - hbcg$	$hbfg$		
f		$abhf$	$acfg$		.	$abch$	$-abcg$	$abfg + achf$	$acgh$	$abgh$
g	$bagh$		$bcfg$		$-bach$		$bcaf$	$bchf$	$bcgh + bafg$	$bahf$
h	$cagh$	$cbhf$			$cabg$	$-cabf$		$cbfg$	caf	$cahf + cbgh$

Viz. the value of the factor is $\{a(fagh) + g(bagh) + h(cagh)\}x^2 + \&c.$, where $fagh = f_{\alpha}a_{\beta}g_{\gamma}h_{\delta}$ is the determinant

$$\begin{vmatrix} f & a & g & h \\ \vdots & \vdots & \vdots & \vdots \end{vmatrix},$$

the suffixes in the four lines being $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ respectively. Collecting, this is

$$\begin{aligned} & (\quad + cbhfy - bcfgz + abcw)(\quad + hy - gz + aw) \\ & + (-caghx \quad + acfgz + abcw)(-hx \quad + fz + bw) \\ & + (baghx - abhfy \quad + habcw)(gx - fy \quad + cw) \\ & + (-afghx - bfg hy - cfghz \quad)(ax + by + cz \quad) \\ & + bcgh\{w(ax + by + cz) - x(\quad hy - gz + aw)\} \\ & + cahf\{w(ax + by + cz) - y(-hx + fz + bw)\} \\ & + abfg\{w(ax + by + cz) - z(gx - fy + cw)\} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$AP + BQ + CR + DS = 0.$$

{Surface abcd $\alpha\beta$.}

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where

$$\begin{aligned} A &= \{-bcghx + cbhfy - bcfgz + abcw\}, \\ B &= \{-caghx + cahfy + acfgz + abcw\}, \\ C &= \{baghx - abhfy + abfgz + habcw\}, \\ D &= \{-afghx - bfg hy - cfghz + (bcgh + cahf + abfg)w\}, \\ P &= (\quad + hy - gz + aw), \\ Q &= (-hx \quad + fz + bw), \\ R &= (gx - fy \quad + cw), \\ S &= (ax + by + cz \quad) = 0, \end{aligned}$$

the right-hand factors vanishing for the values $ux_a + vx_b$ of the coordinates.

38. It thus appears so far that the factor is $= O^1$; it is, in fact, $= O^2$, viz. we can show that, operating upon it with

$$\Delta = X\delta_x + Y\delta_y + Z\delta_z + W\delta_w,$$

the value (for any point of the line ab) is $= 0$. We have

$$\Delta\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 = \frac{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}l_{b\alpha} + \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}l_{a\alpha}}{2\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}}\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}\Delta\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2,$$

where $l_{b\alpha}(= \Delta\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha})$ is what $\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}$ becomes on writing therein (X, Y, Z, W) in place of (x, y, z, w) . Writing, as before, for x, y, z, w the values $ux_a + vx_b$, &c., we have

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = -v \cdot ab\alpha, \quad \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = u \cdot ab\alpha;$$

and putting for shortness

$$-v \cdot l_{b\alpha} + u \cdot l_{a\alpha} = lk\alpha, \quad \&c.,$$

the expression in question, divided by $\sqrt{-uv}$, is

$$= -2vu\{ab\alpha \cdot \Delta\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - \&c.\} + \{lk\alpha \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - \&c.\},$$

where, denoting the determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z & W \\ ux_a - vx_b & uy_a - vy_b & uz_a - vz_b & uw_a - vw_b \end{vmatrix}$$

by (a', b', c', f', g', h') , we have

$$lk\alpha = a'f_\alpha + b'g_\alpha + c'h_\alpha + f'a_\alpha + g'b_\alpha + h'c_\alpha.$$

But

$$ab\alpha \cdot \Delta \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 = \Delta ab\alpha \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2,$$

since $ab\alpha$ is independent of (x, y, z, w) ; and the expression is

$$= -2vu\Delta(AP + BQ + CR + DS) + AP' + BQ' + CR' + DS'.$$

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Here P', Q', R', S' denote $h'y - g'z + a'w$, &c.; and where, finally, x, y, z, w are to be replaced by $ux_a + vx_b$, &c. Since for these values P, Q, R, S vanish, the expression becomes

$$= -2vu(A\Delta P + B\Delta Q + C\Delta R + D\Delta S) + AP' + BQ' + CR' + DS',$$

that is

$$= A(P' - 2vu\Delta P) + B(Q' - 2vu\Delta Q) + C(R' - 2vu\Delta R) + D(S' - 2vu\Delta S).$$

And we have, in fact, $P' - 2vu\Delta P = 0$, &c. For, writing for a moment

$$\begin{aligned} x, y, z, w &= ux_a + vx_b, \quad uy_a + vy_b, \quad uz_a + vz_b, \quad uw_a + vw_b, \\ x', y', z', w' &= ux_a - vx_b, \quad uy_a - vy_b, \quad uz_a - vz_b, \quad uw_a - vw_b, \end{aligned}$$

then, for instance,

$$S' = a'x + b'y + c'z,$$

where

$$a', b', c' = Yz' - Zy', \quad Zx' - Xz', \quad Xy' - Yx';$$

and thence

$$S' = - \begin{vmatrix} X & Y & Z \\ x & y & z \\ x' & y' & z' \end{vmatrix} = 2uv(aX + bY + cZ) = 2uv\Delta S;$$

and similarly for the other equations. The factor is thus $= O^2$; there is only one such factor, and the line ab is double.

(2) The line α is an 8-tuple line: in fact, for a point on the line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = 0$; and the factor vanishes, being $= O^1$. Each of the factors is O^1 , and the norm is $= O^8$.

39. (3) The line $[ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma]$ is a double line. To prove this, observe first that for a point on this line we have $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = 0$.

Taking as before $z = 0$, $w = 0$ for the equation of the line $ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma$, we have $h_\alpha = 0$, $h_\beta = 0$, $h_\gamma = 0$, and $z_a w_b - z_b w_a = 0$; or say $w_a = \lambda z_a$, $w_b = \lambda z_b$; whence, writing for shortness

$$I = -(g - \lambda a)x + (f + \lambda b)y,$$

viz. $I_\alpha = -(g_\alpha - \lambda a_\alpha)x + (f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha)y$, we have (when $z = 0$, $w = 0$)

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = z_a I_\alpha, \quad \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = z_b I_\alpha,$$

or, omitting the factor $\sqrt{z_a z_b}$, $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}} = I_\alpha$; and so for $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}}$ and $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}}$. The factor thus is

$$I_\alpha \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - I_\beta \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 + I_\gamma \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2;$$

viz. writing $z = 0$, $w = 0$ in the expressions of $\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2$, &c., this may be written

$$\Sigma[(g - \lambda a)x - (f + \lambda b)y]\{(agh)x^2 + [(ahf) + (bgh)]xy + (bhf)y^2\},$$

where observe that Σ denotes a sum of three terms of the form

$$\alpha \cdot \beta\gamma\delta - \beta \cdot \gamma\delta\alpha + \gamma \cdot \delta\alpha\beta.$$

{Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.}

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Adding thereto a fourth term $-\delta \cdot \alpha\beta\gamma$, the value of the sum would be $= \alpha\beta\gamma\delta$, or the sum of the three terms is $= \alpha\beta\gamma\delta + \delta \cdot \alpha\beta\gamma$, where the symbols represent determinants. But in each case the determinant $\alpha\beta\gamma$ is $= 0$, as containing the column $h_\alpha, h_\beta, h_\gamma$, the terms of which are each $= 0$: thus $\Sigma g \cdot agh$ is $gagh - g_\delta \cdot agh$, where in $gagh$ the suffixes are $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$, and in agh they are α, β, γ : that is, we have $\Sigma g \cdot agh = gagh$. And the whole expression thus is

$$\begin{aligned} &= x^3(gagh - \lambda aagh) \\ &\quad + x^2y(gahf - \lambda aahf + gbgh - \lambda abgh - fagh - \lambda bagh) \\ &\quad + xy^2(gbhf - \lambda abhf - fahf - \lambda bahf - fbgh - \lambda bbgh) \\ &\quad + y^3(-fbbf - \lambda bbbf), \end{aligned}$$

where $gahf$ denotes the determinant

$$\begin{vmatrix} g & a & h & f \\ \vdots & \vdots & \vdots & \vdots \end{vmatrix}$$

with the suffixes $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ in the four lines respectively, and so in other cases. The terms, such as $gagh$, which contain a twice-repeated letter, vanish of themselves; and in the coefficients of x^2y and xy^2 , the terms which do not separately vanish destroy each other in pairs, $gahf - fagh = 0$, &c.; whence the factor vanishes, being $= O^1$. There are two such factors (viz. the zero term $\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\delta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$ may be taken with the sign $+$ or $-$ at pleasure), and the norm is thus $= O^2$.

40. But the line is tacnodal, each sheet of the surface touching along the line in question the hyperboloid $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$. To prove this, write

$$\Delta = X\delta_x + Y\delta_y + Z\delta_z + W\delta_w;$$

we have for the hyperboloid, writing $z = 0$, $w = 0$,

$$\Delta \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = [(afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y)Z + (abg \cdot x - abf \cdot y)W];$$

and it is to be shown that

$$\Delta(\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}}\mathfrak{p}_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2 \mp \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\delta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2)$$

each contain the factor $\Delta \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$; or, what is the same thing, that

$$\Delta \Sigma \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2$$

contains the factor in question, Σ denoting the sum of the first three terms of the original expression. The value is

$$= \Sigma \left\{ \frac{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}P_{b\alpha} + \mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}P_{a\alpha}}{2\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}} \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}} \Delta \mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 \right\};$$

where $P_{a\alpha} = \Delta \mathbf{p}_{a\alpha}$ denotes what $\mathbf{p}_{a\alpha}$ becomes on writing therein X, Y, Z, W for x, y, z, w ; and the like as to $P_{b\alpha}$. Substituting for $\mathbf{p}_{a\alpha}$ and $\mathbf{p}_{b\alpha}$ their values $z_a I_\alpha$ and $z_b I_\alpha$, and multiplying by $\sqrt{z_a z_b}$, the expression is

$$= \Sigma \{ (z_a P_{b\alpha} + z_b P_{a\alpha}) \mathbf{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 + 2z_a z_b I_\alpha \Delta \mathbf{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 \}.$$

{Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.}

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where we have

$$\begin{aligned} z_a P_{b\alpha} + z_b P_{a\alpha} &= z_b \{ x_a (Zg_\alpha - Wa_\alpha) + y_a (-Zf_\alpha - Wb_\alpha) \\ &\quad + z_a [X(-g_\alpha + \lambda a_\alpha) + Y(f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha) + (\lambda Z - W)c_\alpha] \} \\ &\quad + z_a \{ x_b (Zg_\alpha - Wa_\alpha) + y_b (-Zf_\alpha - Wb_\alpha) \\ &\quad + z_b [X(-g_\alpha + \lambda a_\alpha) + Y(f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha) + (\lambda Z - W)c_\alpha] \} \\ &= (z_b x_a + z_a x_b)(Zg_\alpha - Wa_\alpha) \\ &\quad + (z_b y_a + z_a y_b)(-Zf_\alpha - Wb_\alpha) \\ &\quad + 2z_a z_b \{ X(-g_\alpha + \lambda a_\alpha) + Y(f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha) + (\lambda Z - W)c_\alpha \}. \end{aligned}$$

Also

$$\begin{aligned} z_a z_b I_\alpha &= z_a z_b \{ (-g_\alpha + \lambda a_\alpha)x + (f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha)y \}, \\ \mathbf{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 &= x^2 \cdot agh + xy(ahf + bgh) + y^2 \cdot bhf, \\ \Delta \mathbf{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 &= X \{ 2x \cdot agh + y(ahf + bgh) \} \\ &\quad + Y \{ x(ahf + bgh) + 2y \cdot bhf \} \\ &\quad + Z \{ x(cgh + afg) + y(bfg + chf) \} \\ &\quad + W \{ x(abg - cah) + y(bch - abf) \}. \end{aligned}$$

41. The whole expression is a linear function of X, Y, Z, W , and it is easy to see *a priori*, or to verify, that the coefficients of X, Y , each of them vanish. The coefficient of Z is

$$\begin{aligned} &= \Sigma \{ (z_b x_a + z_a x_b)g_\alpha - (z_b y_a + z_a y_b)f_\alpha + 2\lambda z_a z_b c_\alpha \} \mathbf{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 \\ &\quad + \Sigma 2z_a z_b [(-g_\alpha + \lambda a_\alpha)x + (f_\alpha + \lambda b_\alpha)y] [x(cgh + afg) + y(bfg + chf)], \end{aligned}$$

with a like expression for the coefficient of W .

The foregoing expression may be written

$$\begin{aligned} &(z_b x_a + z_a x_b) \Sigma g [agh \cdot x^2 + (ahf + bgh)xy + bhf \cdot y^2] \\ &\quad - (z_b y_a + z_a y_b) \Sigma f [agh \cdot x^2 + (ahf + bgh)xy + bhf \cdot y^2] \\ &\quad + 2\lambda z_a z_b \Sigma \{ c [agh \cdot x^2 + (ahf + bgh)xy + bhf \cdot y^2] \\ &\quad \quad + (ax + by) [(cgh + afg)x + (bfg + chf)y] \} \\ &\quad + 2z_a z_b \Sigma (-gx + fy) [(cgh + afg)x + (bfg + chf)y]. \end{aligned}$$

The first sum is

$$x^2 \cdot gagh + xy(gahf + gbgh) + y^2 \cdot gbhf = -xy \cdot afg h - y^2 \cdot bfg h = -h_\delta y (afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y);$$

where afg, bfg denote determinants with the suffixes α, β, γ . Similarly the second sum is

$$= -h_\delta x (afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y);$$

the third sum is

$$(a_\delta x + b_\delta y) (afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y),$$

and the fourth sum is

$$(-g_\delta x + f_\delta y) (afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y).$$

{Surface $abcd\alpha\beta$.}

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The whole coefficient of Z thus contains the factor $(afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y)$; and similarly it would appear that the whole coefficient of W contains the factor $(abg \cdot x - abf \cdot y)$, the other factor being the same in each case; viz. the two terms together are

$$\left\{ \begin{array}{l} -(z_b x_a + z_a x_b) h_\delta y \\ +(z_b y_a + z_a y_b) h_\delta x \\ +2\lambda z_a z_b (a_\delta x + b_\delta y) \\ +2z_a z_b (-g_\delta x + f_\delta y) \end{array} \right\} \{Z(afg \cdot x + bfg \cdot y) + W(abg \cdot x - abf \cdot y)\};$$

where the second factor is $\Delta p_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$, which is the required result. See post, Nos. 59 et seq.

42. (4) The line $[\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta]$ is an 8-tuple line; in fact, for any point of the line in question we have

$$p_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 = 0, \quad p_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 = 0, \quad p_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2 = 0, \quad p_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = 0;$$

whence each factor is O^1 , or the norm is O^8 .

I notice that the surface meets the quadric $p_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$ in

lines α, β, γ	each 8 times	24,
line $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$		16,
lines $(ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma)$	each 4 times	8,
		$24 \times 2 = 48.$

Surface $a\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon$.

43. The equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & (p_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 p_{a\alpha\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta + p_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 p_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{a\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta)^2 \\ & - 4p_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 p_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 p_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 p_{a\alpha} p_{\delta a} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} & (p_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 p_{a\alpha\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta - p_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 p_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{a\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta)^2 \\ & - 4p_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 p_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 p_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 p_{\beta\alpha\delta}^2 p_{\gamma\alpha\delta}^2 p_{\beta a} p_{\gamma a} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

the equivalence of the two depending on the identity

$$p_{\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta \cdot p_{a\alpha\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta - p_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 p_{\delta\beta\gamma}^2 p_{a\alpha} p_{\delta a} + p_{\beta\alpha\delta}^2 p_{\gamma\alpha\delta}^2 p_{\beta a} p_{\gamma a} = 0;$$

where, as before, $p_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$ is the equation of the quadric through the lines α, β, ϵ , and $p_{a\alpha} = 0$ is the equation of the plane through the line α and the point a ; viz. $p_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2$, &c., and $p_{a\alpha}$, &c., have the values already mentioned: $p_{a\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta = 0$ as already mentioned is the cubic surface through the lines $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ and $a\alpha\beta, a\gamma\delta$.

{Surface $a\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon$.}

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44. *Investigation.* In the projection, using line-coordinates, the equation of the conic touching the five lines may be written

$$\left| \begin{array}{c} (\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 \\ (P, Q, R)^2 \end{array} \right| = 0;$$

where the symbol denotes a determinant the last five lines of which are obtained by giving to (P, Q, R) the suffixes $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta, \epsilon$ respectively. This is at once transformed into

$$\alpha\beta\epsilon \cdot \gamma\delta\epsilon \cdot \alpha\gamma\Delta \cdot \delta\beta\Delta - \alpha\gamma\epsilon \cdot \delta\beta\epsilon \cdot \alpha\beta\Delta \cdot \gamma\delta\Delta = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \alpha\gamma\Delta \cdot \delta\beta\Delta - \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 \alpha\beta\Delta \cdot \gamma\delta\Delta = 0;$$

or say

$$\begin{aligned} & \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 (A''\xi + B''\eta + C''\zeta)(A'''\xi + B'''\eta + C'''\zeta) \\ & - \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 (A\xi + B\eta + C\zeta)(A'\xi + B'\eta + C'\zeta) = 0; \end{aligned}$$

where $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2$, &c., signify as before; and

$$A\xi + B\eta + C\zeta = \begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ P_\beta & Q_\beta & R_\beta \end{vmatrix},$$

and so for $A'\xi + B'\eta + C'\zeta$, &c., the suffixes for A', B', C' being (γ, δ) ; and those for $A''\xi + B''\eta + C''\zeta$ and $A'''\xi + B'''\eta + C'''\zeta$ being (α, γ) and (δ, β) respectively.

45. Passing to the reciprocal equation, and making the conic pass through the point a , we obtain the equation of the surface in the form

$$\begin{aligned} & \left\{ \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A & B & C \\ A' & B' & C' \end{vmatrix} - \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix} \right\}^2 \\ & + 4\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A & B & C \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \end{vmatrix} \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A' & B' & C' \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

or in the equivalent form, where in the first term we have $+$ instead of $-$, and in the second term the determinants are

$$\begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A & B & C \\ A''' & B''' & C''' \end{vmatrix}, \quad \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A' & B' & C' \\ A'' & B'' & C'' \end{vmatrix}.$$

46. To reduce this result, observe that we have

$$A, B, C = \begin{vmatrix} hy - gz + aw & -hx + fz + bw & gx - fy + cw \\ h'y - g'z + a'w & -h'x + f'z + b'w & g'x - f'y + c'w \end{vmatrix}.$$

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Here, for convenience, I retain the unaccented and accented letters $(a, \dots)$, $(a', \dots)$ instead of these letters with the suffixes α and β respectively. Writing as before

$$\begin{aligned} L &= (af' - a'f)x + \dots, \\ M &= (ag' - a'g)x + \dots, \\ N &= (ah' - a'h)x + \dots, \\ \Omega &= (gh' - g'h)x + \dots, \end{aligned}$$

then

$$A = \Omega x - Lw, \quad B = \Omega y - Mw, \quad C = \Omega z - Nw,$$

and similarly

$$A' = \Omega'x - L'w, \quad B' = \Omega'y - M'w, \quad C' = \Omega'z - N'w;$$

where for L', M', N', Ω' we have $(a'', \dots)$ and $(a''', \dots)$. Hence

$$BC' - B'C = w \begin{vmatrix} y & z & w \\ M & N & \Omega \\ M' & N' & \Omega' \end{vmatrix},$$

with like expressions for $CA' - C'A$ and $AB' - A'B$; and substituting, we have

$$\begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A & B & C \\ A' & B' & C' \end{vmatrix} = w \begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ x & y & z & w \\ L & M & N & \Omega \\ L' & M' & N' & \Omega' \end{vmatrix}.$$

Or substituting for p_a, q_a, r_a their values $xw_a - wx_a, yw_a - wy_a, zw_a - wz_a$, this is

$$\begin{vmatrix} p_a & q_a & r_a \\ A & B & C \\ A' & B' & C' \end{vmatrix} = -w^2 \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ L & M & N & \Omega \\ L' & M' & N' & \Omega' \end{vmatrix}.$$

Whence, omitting the factors w^2 , the equation is

$$\left\{ \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ L & M & N & \Omega \\ L' & M' & N' & \Omega' \end{vmatrix} - \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ L'' & M'' & N'' & \Omega'' \\ L''' & M''' & N''' & \Omega''' \end{vmatrix} \right\}^2 \\ + 4\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ L & M & N & \Omega \\ L'' & M'' & N'' & \Omega'' \end{vmatrix} \begin{vmatrix} x & y & z & w \\ x_a & y_a & z_a & w_a \\ L' & M' & N' & \Omega' \\ L''' & M''' & N''' & \Omega''' \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

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Here I recall that for $(L, \dots)$, $(L', \dots)$, $(L'', \dots)$, $(L''', \dots)$ the suffixes are (α, β) , (γ, δ) , (α, γ) , and (δ, β) respectively. The values of the first two determinants thus are $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta$ and $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta$ respectively: that of the third is $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \alpha\gamma$; viz. this is $= \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}$; similarly, that of the fourth is $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\delta}^3 \cdot \delta\beta$, which is $= -\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta = +\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta\beta}^3 \cdot \delta\gamma$; or finally this is $= \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\gamma}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}$. And we have thus the before-mentioned equation of the surface.

47. *Singularities.* The equation of the surface shows that:

(0) The point a is a 2-conical point: for it $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta} = 0$.

(2) The line α is a 4-tuple line: for any point on it $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\gamma}^3 \cdot \delta\beta = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha a}^2 = 0$.

(4) The line $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \epsilon)$ is a 2-tuple line: for any point on it $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 = 0$.

(10) The excuboquartic $\alpha\beta\epsilon.\gamma\delta.a$ is a simple curve. In fact, for any point of this curve we have $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\alpha\beta}^3 \cdot \gamma\delta = 0$, these two surfaces intersecting in the lines α, β and the curve. It is, moreover, obvious that the surface is touched along the curve by the hyperboloid $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2$.

I notice that the surface meets the quadric $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$ in

lines (α, β, γ)	each 4 times,	12,
line $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$	twice,	4,
line $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \epsilon)$	twice,	4,
curve $a\alpha\beta\gamma.\delta\epsilon$	twice,	8,
		$14 \times 2 = 28.$

Surface $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$.

48. The equation of the surface may be written

$$\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\zeta}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\zeta}^2 - \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\zeta}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\zeta}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0,$$

where $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$ is the equation of the quadric through the lines α, β, ϵ ; viz. $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2$ has the value already mentioned.

The form is one of 45 like forms depending on the partitionment

$$\left\{ \begin{array}{l} \alpha\beta.\gamma\delta \\ \alpha\gamma.\delta\beta \\ \alpha\delta.\beta\gamma \end{array} \right\} (\epsilon, \zeta)$$

of the six letters.

{Surface $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$.}

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49. *Investigation.* The projections of the six lines are tangents to a conic: the condition for this is $(P, Q, R)^2 = 0$, where the left-hand side represents the determinant obtained by writing successively $(P_\alpha, Q_\alpha, R_\alpha)$, &c., for (P, Q, R) . The equation may be written

$$\alpha\beta\epsilon \cdot \gamma\delta\epsilon \cdot \alpha\gamma\zeta \cdot \delta\beta\zeta - \alpha\beta\zeta \cdot \gamma\delta\zeta \cdot \alpha\gamma\epsilon \cdot \delta\beta\epsilon = 0,$$

where

$$\alpha\beta\epsilon = \begin{vmatrix} P_\alpha & Q_\alpha & R_\alpha \\ P_\beta & Q_\beta & R_\beta \\ P_\epsilon & Q_\epsilon & R_\epsilon \end{vmatrix},$$

and substituting for P_α , &c., their values, we have $\alpha\beta\epsilon = w \cdot \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2$; whence the foregoing result.

50. *Singularities.* The equation shows that

- (2) The line α is a 2-tuple line: $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\zeta}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\zeta}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 = 0$.
- (4) The line $(\alpha, \beta, \epsilon, \zeta)$ is a simple line: $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\zeta}^2 = 0$.
- (9) The quadriquadric $\alpha\beta\epsilon.\gamma\delta\zeta = 0$ is a simple curve on the surface:
for each point of the curve $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0$, $\mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\zeta}^2 = 0$.

It may be remarked that the surface meets the hyperboloid $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2$ in

lines $(\alpha, \beta, \epsilon)$	each twice,	6,
line $(\alpha, \beta, \epsilon, \gamma)$	once,	2,
line $(\alpha, \beta, \epsilon, \delta)$	once,	2,
line $(\alpha, \beta, \epsilon, \zeta)$	once,	2,
curve $\alpha\beta\epsilon.\gamma\delta\zeta$	twice,	4,
		$2 \times 8 = 16.$

51. It might be thought that there should be on the surface some curve $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$, such as the cubic $abcdef$ on the surface $abcdef$; but I cannot find that this is so. The equation of the surface is satisfied if we have simultaneously (λ being arbitrary)

$$\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\zeta}^2 - \lambda \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\zeta}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\gamma\epsilon}^2 = 0,$$

$$\lambda \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\epsilon}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\zeta}^2 - \mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\zeta}^2 \mathfrak{p}_{\delta\beta\epsilon}^2 = 0;$$

which equations represent quartic surfaces, the first of them having α for a double line, and passing through the lines $\beta, \gamma, \epsilon, \zeta$ ($13 + 4 \times 5 = 33$ conditions, so that the equation of such a surface contains

only an arbitrary parameter λ); and the second having δ for a double line, and passing through the lines $\beta, \gamma, \epsilon, \zeta$. But I see no condition by which λ can be determined so as to have the same value in the two equations respectively. Of course, leaving it arbitrary, the two quartic surfaces intersect in the lines $\beta, \gamma, \epsilon, \zeta$ and in a curve of the order 12 depending on the arbitrary value of λ , which curve lies on the surface $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$.

{Surface $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta\epsilon\zeta$.}

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The Excuboquartic $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon, a$.

52. The notion is, that we have a fixed point a , two fixed lines δ, ϵ , and a singly infinite series of lines, or say the generating lines of a skew surface: each generating line determines, with the point a , a plane; and if in this plane we draw, meeting the lines δ, ϵ , a line to meet the generating line in a point P , then the locus of this point P is the curve about to be considered.

53. In the case in question, the singly infinite series of lines is that of the lines which meet each of the lines α, β, γ , or say these are the generatrices of the hyperboloid $\alpha\beta\gamma$: the locus, or curve $\alpha\beta\gamma, \delta\epsilon, a$, is (as mentioned above) an excuboquartic. It is not necessary for the purpose of the memoir, but it is interesting to consider in conjunction therewith the excuboquartic arising in like manner from the directrices of the hyperboloid; it will appear that the two curves are the complete intersection of the quadric $\alpha\beta\gamma$ by a quartic surface. Observe that the two curves are given as follows: viz. considering for the quadric $\alpha\beta\gamma$ any tangent-plane through the point a , and drawing in this plane, to meet the lines δ and ϵ , a line, this meets the section of the quadric surface by the tangent-plane in two points, the locus of which is the aggregate of the two curves: viz. the section being a line-pair, the two points belong, one of them to a generatrix and the other to a directrix of the quadric surface.

54. It is convenient to take $x = 0, y = 0$ for the equations of the line δ ; $z = 0, w = 0$ for those of the line ϵ : for then, for any plane $Ax + By + Cz + Dw = 0$, the line in this plane and meeting the lines δ and ϵ has for its equations $Ax + By = 0, Cz + Dw = 0$; or, what is the same thing, for the plane $P = 0$ the equations of the line are $P_{xy} = 0, P_{zw} = 0$, where P_{xy}, P_{zw} denote the terms in x, y and in z, w respectively.

I take also x_0, y_0, z_0, w_0 for the coordinates of the point a , and $PS - QR = 0$ for the equation of the quadric surface, P, Q, R, S being given linear functions of (x, y, z, w) : we have then, say, $P - \theta R = 0, Q - \theta S = 0$ for the equations of any generatrix, and $P - \phi Q = 0, R - \phi S = 0$ for the equations of any directrix of the hyperboloid.

The equation of the plane through the point a and the generatrix $P - \theta R = 0, Q - \theta S = 0$, is clearly

$$(Q_0 - \theta S_0)(P - \theta R) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(Q - \theta S) = 0;$$

so that for the line in this plane, meeting the lines δ and ϵ , we have

$$(Q_0 - \theta S_0)(P_{xy} - \theta R_{xy}) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(Q_{xy} - \theta S_{xy}) = 0,$$

$$(Q_0 - \theta S_0)(P_{zw} - \theta R_{zw}) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(Q_{zw} - \theta S_{zw}) = 0;$$

and joining thereto the equations

$$\theta = \frac{P}{R} = \frac{Q}{S} = \frac{P_{xy} + P_{zw}}{R_{xy} + R_{zw}} = \frac{Q_{xy} + Q_{zw}}{R_{xy} + R_{zw}},$$

(equivalent in all to three equations), the elimination of θ gives the required curve: the equations thus are

$$PS - QR = 0,$$

$$(Q_0S - QS_0)(P_{xy}R - PR_{xy}) - (P_0R - PR_0)(Q_{xy}S - QS_{xy}) = 0,$$

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or, as the second equation may also be written,

$$(Q_0S - QS_0)(P_{xy}R_{zw} - P_{zw}R_{xy}) - (P_0R - PR_0)(Q_{xy}S_{zw} - Q_{zw}S_{xy}) = 0;$$

viz. the second equation represents a cubic surface having upon it the lines $(P = 0, R = 0)$ and $(Q = 0, S = 0)$: it therefore intersects the quadric $PS - QR = 0$ in these two lines, and besides in an excuboquartic curve, which is the required locus.

55. Representing the determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} P & Q & R & S \\ P_0 & Q_0 & R_0 & S_0 \end{vmatrix} \quad \text{by} \quad (a', b', c', f', g', h'),$$

viz. $a' = QR_0 - Q_0R, \dots, f' = PS_0 - P_0S, \dots$; and

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_{xy} & Q_{xy} & R_{xy} & S_{xy} \\ P_{zw} & Q_{zw} & R_{zw} & S_{zw} \end{vmatrix} \quad \text{by} \quad (a, b, c, f, g, h),$$

viz. $a = Q_{xy}R_{zw} - Q_{zw}R_{xy}, \dots$; so that $(a', \dots)$ are linear functions, $(a, \dots)$ quadric functions, of the coordinates; the equation of the cubic surface is

$$gb' - bg' = 0,$$

viz. the excuboquartic arising from the generatrices is the partial intersection of the quadric $PS - QR = 0$ and the cubic $gb' - g'b = 0$; the two surfaces besides intersecting in the lines $(P = 0, R = 0)$ and $(Q = 0, S = 0)$.

It appears, in the same manner, that the excuboquartic arising from the directrices is the partial intersection of the quadric $PS - QR = 0$ and the cubic $hc' - ch' = 0$; the two surfaces besides intersecting in the lines $(P = 0, Q = 0)$ and $(R = 0, S = 0)$.

56. But the elimination may be performed in a different manner, as follows: from the first two equations in θ , multiplying by $P_{zw}, -P_{xy}$ and adding, and so with $Q_{zw}, -Q_{xy}$, &c., we obtain

$$\begin{aligned} (Q_0 - \theta S_0)(-\theta b) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(-c + \theta f) &= 0, \\ (Q_0 - \theta S_0)(c + \theta a) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(\theta g) &= 0, \\ (Q_0 - \theta S_0)(-b) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(a + \theta h) &= 0, \\ (Q_0 - \theta S_0)(f - \theta h) - (P_0 - \theta R_0)(g) &= 0. \end{aligned}$$

We then have

$$\theta = \frac{-c + \theta f}{a + \theta h} = \frac{c + \theta a}{f - \theta h},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$h\theta^2 + (a - f)\theta + c = 0.$$

Using this equation, written in the form $(a + \theta h)\theta = -c + \theta f$, to transform the first or third of the four equations in θ , we obtain

$$-aP_0 - bQ_0 - cR_0 + \theta(-hP_0 + fR_0 + bS_0) = 0;$$

and using the same equation, written in the form $(f - \theta h)\theta = c + \theta a$, to transform the second or fourth equation, we obtain

$$gP_0 - fQ_0 + cS_0 + \theta(hQ_0 - gR_0 + aS_0) = 0;$$

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and hence, eliminating θ , we obtain

$$(hQ_0 - gR_0 + aS_0)(-aP_0 - bQ_0 - cR_0) - (-hP_0 + fR_0 + bS_0)(gP_0 - fQ_0 + cS_0) = 0,$$

which, as being of the second order in $(a, \dots)$, represents a quartic surface. The equation remains unaltered by the interchange of Q, R , and the consequent interchanges among (a, b, c, f, g, h) : hence the quartic surface contains not only the excuboquartic arising from the generatrices, but also that arising from the directrices; and these two curves are the complete intersection of the quartic by the quadric $PS - QR = 0$.

57. I obtain this same result also as follows. Consider a point (P_1, Q_1, R_1, S_1) on the quadric surface; $P_1S_1 - Q_1R_1 = 0$; the tangent plane at the point is

$$PS_1 - QR_1 - RQ_1 + SP_1 = 0;$$

and if this passes through the point a , then

$$P_0S_1 - Q_0R_1 - R_0Q_1 + S_0P_1 = 0.$$

The line which in the tangent-plane meets the lines δ, ϵ is given, as before, by the equations

$$P_{xy}S_1 - Q_{xy}R_1 - R_{xy}Q_1 + S_{xy}P_1 = 0,$$

$$P_{zw}S_1 - Q_{zw}R_1 - R_{zw}Q_1 + S_{zw}P_1 = 0.$$

Remembering the significations of $(a, \dots)$, the last three equations give

$$\begin{aligned} S_1 : R_1 : -Q_1 : -P_1 &= hQ_0 - gR_0 + aS_0 \\ &: -hP_0 + fR_0 + bS_0 \\ &: gP_0 - fQ_0 + cS_0 \\ &: -aP_0 - bQ_0 - cR_0; \end{aligned}$$

and substituting these values in $S_1P_1 - Q_1R_1 = 0$, we have the above equation of the quadric surface.

58. Or again, changing the notation, I take the equation of the quadric surface to be

$$(a, b, c, d, f, g, h, l, m, n)(x, y, z, w)^2 = 0.$$

A tangent-plane hereof is

$$\xi x + \eta y + \zeta z + \omega w = 0,$$

where ξ, η, ζ, ω are any quantities satisfying the relation

$$(A, B, C, D, F, G, H, L, M, N)(\xi, \eta, \zeta, \omega)^2 = 0,$$

the capitals denoting the inverse coefficients.

Supposing that the tangent-plane passes through a fixed point a , coordinates $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$, we have

$$\alpha\xi + \beta\eta + \gamma\zeta + \delta\omega = 0;$$

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and if the equations of the lines δ, ϵ are as before ($x = 0, y = 0$) and ($z = 0, w = 0$); then for the line in the tangent-plane meeting the lines δ, ϵ , we have

$$\xi x + \eta y = 0, \quad \zeta z + \omega w = 0.$$

These last equations may be represented by

$$\xi = ly, \quad \eta = -lx, \quad \zeta = mw, \quad \omega = -mz;$$

and, substituting these values, we have

$$(A, \dots)(ly, -lx, mw, -mz)^2 = 0, \quad (\alpha, \dots)(ly, -lx, mw, -mz)^1 = 0,$$

that is

$$(Ay^2 - 2Hxy + Bx^2, -Fwx + Gyw - Lyz + Mxz, Cw^2 - 2Nwz + Dz^2)(l, m)^2 = 0,$$

and

$$(\alpha y - \beta x, \gamma w - \delta z)(l, m) = 0.$$

Whence, eliminating l, m , we have the quartic equation

$$(Ay^2 - 2Hxy + Bx^2, -Fwx + Gyw - Lyz + Mxz, Cw^2 - 2Nwz + Dz^2)(\gamma w - \delta z, \beta x - \alpha y)^2 = 0.$$

Further Investigation as to the Surface $ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$.

59. The theorem that in the surface $ab\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$, the equation of which is

$$\text{Norm}\{\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}\mathfrak{p}_{\beta\gamma\delta}^2 - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\beta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\gamma\delta\alpha}^2 + \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\gamma}\mathfrak{p}_{b\gamma}}\mathfrak{p}_{\delta\alpha\beta}^2 - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\delta}}\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2\} = 0,$$

the lines $(ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma)$ are tacnodal, each sheet touching along the line the quadric $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$, may be proved in a different manner by investigating the intersection of the surface with the quadric $\mathfrak{p}_{\alpha\beta\gamma}^2$.

For this purpose take the equation of the quadric to be $yz - xw = 0$; the equations of the lines α, β, γ will be

$$\begin{pmatrix} z - \lambda_\alpha w = 0 \\ x - \lambda_\alpha y = 0 \end{pmatrix}, \quad \begin{pmatrix} z - \lambda_\beta w = 0 \\ x - \lambda_\beta y = 0 \end{pmatrix}, \quad \begin{pmatrix} z - \lambda_\gamma w = 0 \\ x - \lambda_\gamma y = 0 \end{pmatrix};$$

and we may write (a, b, c, f, g, h) for the coordinates of the line δ . The equation of the surface will be

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Norm} \left\{ \Sigma \left[\pm \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}}(\lambda_\beta - \lambda_\gamma) \begin{pmatrix} (a - f)xz - (\lambda_\beta + \lambda_\gamma)yz + \lambda_\beta\lambda_\gamma yw \\ (b - g)\lambda_\beta\lambda_\gamma(yz - xw) \\ c(z - \lambda_\beta w)(z - \lambda_\gamma w) \\ h(x - \lambda_\beta y)(x - \lambda_\gamma z) \end{pmatrix} \right] \right. \\ \left. - \sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\delta}\mathfrak{p}_{b\delta}}(\lambda_\beta - \lambda_\gamma)(\lambda_\gamma - \lambda_\alpha)(\lambda_\alpha - \lambda_\beta)(yz - xw) \right\}. \end{aligned}$$

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Here Σ denotes the sum of the three terms obtained by the cyclical interchange of α, β, γ ; and

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = (z_a - \lambda w_a)(x - \lambda y) - (x_a - \lambda y_a)(z - \lambda w),$$

$$\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = (z_b - \lambda w_b)(x - \lambda y) - (x_b - \lambda y_b)(z - \lambda w);$$

λ here standing for λ_α ; and similarly for $\mathfrak{p}_{a\beta}$, &c.

60. To obtain the intersection with $xw - yz = 0$, writing $w = \frac{yz}{x}$, then

$$\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha} = \left[z_a - \lambda w_a - \frac{z}{x}(x_a - \lambda y_a) \right] (x - \lambda y), \quad (\lambda = \lambda_\alpha),$$

$$\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha} = \left[z_b - \lambda w_b - \frac{z}{x}(x_b - \lambda y_b) \right] (x - \lambda y);$$

or say

$$\sqrt{\mathfrak{p}_{a\alpha}\mathfrak{p}_{b\alpha}} = \sqrt{M_\alpha}(x - \lambda_\alpha y).$$

Also the expression in braces becomes

$$= \{(a-f)\frac{z}{x} + c\frac{z^2}{x^2} + h\}(x - \lambda_\beta y)(x - \lambda_\gamma y);$$

so that the norm in question is

$$\text{Norm } \Sigma \sqrt{M_\alpha}(\lambda_\beta - \lambda_\gamma) \{(a-f)\frac{z}{x} + c\frac{z^2}{x^2} + h\}(x - \lambda_\alpha y)(x - \lambda_\beta y)(x - \lambda_\gamma y);$$

or say

$$\text{Norm } \Sigma \sqrt{M_\alpha}(\lambda_\beta - \lambda_\gamma) \{hx^2 + (a-f)zx + cz^2\}(x - \lambda_\alpha y)(x - \lambda_\beta y)(x - \lambda_\gamma y);$$

where M_α is now considered to stand for

$$\{(z_ax - zx_a) - \lambda(w_ax - y_az)\}\{(z_bx - zx_b) - \lambda(w_bx - y_bz)\}.$$

Observing that the norm was originally the product of 8 factors, this breaks up into

$$\{hx^2 + (a-f)zx + cz^2\}^8 \{(x - \lambda_\alpha y)(x - \lambda_\beta y)(x - \lambda_\gamma y)\}^8 = 0,$$

and

$$\text{Norm}^2 \sqrt{M_\alpha}(\lambda_\beta - \lambda_\gamma) = 0,$$

where the new norm is the product of 4 factors.

61. Writing for greater convenience λ, μ, ν in place of $\lambda_\alpha, \lambda_\beta, \lambda_\gamma$, and observing that M_α is a quadric function of λ_α , that is of λ , the last-mentioned norm is

$$\text{Norm } \sqrt{A + B\lambda + C\lambda^2}(\mu - \nu),$$

which is easily seen to be

$$= (4AC - B^2)(\mu - \nu)^2(\nu - \lambda)^2(\lambda - \mu)^2;$$

or writing for a moment

$$(A + B\lambda + C\lambda^2) = (P - Q\lambda)(P' - Q'\lambda),$$

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whence

$$A = PP', \quad B = -(PQ' + P'Q), \quad C = QQ';$$

then

$$4AC - B^2 = -(PQ' - P'Q)^2;$$

and we have

$$P, Q = z_ax - zx_a, \quad w_ax - y_az,$$

$$P', Q' = z_bx - zx_b, \quad w_bx - y_bz,$$

whence

$$\begin{aligned} PQ' - P'Q &= (z_aw_b - z_bw_a)x^2 \\ &\quad + [y_az_b - y_bz_a - (x_aw_b - x_bw_a)]xz \\ &\quad + (x_ay_b - x_by_a)z^2; \end{aligned}$$

viz. if (a, b, c, f, g, h) are the coordinates of the line ab , this is

$$= hx^2 + (a-f)xz + cz^2.$$

Hence, omitting the constant factor $(\mu - \nu)^4(\nu - \lambda)^4(\lambda - \mu)^4$

$$\{\text{that is } (\lambda_\beta - \lambda_\gamma)^4(\lambda_\gamma - \lambda_\alpha)^4(\lambda_\alpha - \lambda_\beta)^4\},$$

the foregoing equation $\text{Norm}^2 = 0$ becomes

$$[hx^2 + (a - f)xz + cz^2]^4 = 0,$$

and the intersections of the quadric with the surface are obtained by combining the equation $xw - yz = 0$ with the several equations

$$\{hx^2 + (a - f)xz + cz^2\}^8 = 0, \quad \{(x - \lambda_\alpha y)(x - \lambda_\beta y)(x - \lambda_\gamma y)\}^8 = 0,$$

$$\{hx^2 + (a - f)zx + cz^2\}^4 = 0;$$

viz. these are

lines $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$	each 8 times	16,
line $(x = 0, z = 0)$	16 times	16,
lines α, β, γ	each 8 times	24,
line $(x = 0, y = 0)$	24 times	24,
lines $[ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma]$	each 4 times	8,
line $(x = 0, z = 0)$	8 times	8,
$(16 + 24 + 8) \times 2 = 48 + 48.$		

But it is clear that the lines $(x = 0, y = 0)$ and $(x = 0, z = 0)$ are introduced by the process of elimination, and are no part of the intersection. The complete intersection consists of the lines $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$ each 8 times, the lines (α, β, γ) each 8 times, and the lines $[ab, \alpha, \beta, \gamma]$ each 4 times. But the last-mentioned lines being only double lines on the surface, this means that the two sheets each touch the quadric surface, or that the lines are tacnodal.

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[504]

On the Mechanical Description of Certain Sextic Curves.

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. IV. (1871–1873), pp. 105–111. Read April 11, 1872.]

THE curves in question might be taken to be those described by a point C rigidly connected with points A and B , each of which describes a circle: but the construction is considered under a somewhat more general form. I consider a quadrilateral, the sides of which are a, b, c, d , and the inclinations of these to a fixed line $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$. This being so, if a, b, c, d , and one of the angles, say δ , are constant, then we have between the three variable angles the relations

$$a \cos \alpha + b \cos \beta + c \cos \gamma + d \cos \delta = 0,$$

$$a \sin \alpha + b \sin \beta + c \sin \gamma + d \sin \delta = 0,$$

giving rise to a single relation between any two of the variable angles; and we consider a curve such that the coordinates x, y of any point thereof are given linear functions of the sines and cosines of the three variable angles, or, what is the same thing, of the sines and cosines of any two of these angles. We thus unite together what would otherwise be distinct cases; for everything is symmetrical in regard to the sides a, b, c and the corresponding variable angles α, β, γ , irrespectively of the order of succession of these sides: and we can thus, in the discussion of the curve, employ any two at pleasure, say α, β , of the variable angles, without determining whether the sides a, b are contiguous or opposite.

Eliminating, then, the variable angle γ , we obtain between α, β a relation which, if we write therein $\tan \frac{1}{2}\alpha = u$, $\tan \frac{1}{2}\beta = v$, takes the form

$$(*\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0;$$

viz. either of the variables u, v is expressible rationally in terms of the other of them and of the root of a quartic function thereof; say v is a rational function of u and $\sqrt{U}$.

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And hence a curve for which the coordinates x, y are rational functions of u, v , is a curve having a deficiency $D = 1$, or, what is the same thing, having a number of dps. less by unity than the maximum number $\{= \frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2), \text{ if } n \text{ be the order of the curve}\}$.

It will further appear that the relation $(*\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0$ is satisfied by the values $u = v = i$ and $u = v = -i$ (if, as usual, $i = \sqrt{-1}$).

In the curve in question, the coordinates (x, y) are given linear functions of the sines and cosines of α, β ; and if we make the curve meet an arbitrary line $Ax + By + C = 0$, we obtain between the sines and cosines of α, β a linear relation which, substituting therein the expressions in terms of u, v , takes the form

$$(*\chi u, 1)^2(1 + v^2) + (*\chi v, 1)^2(1 + u^2) = 0,$$

viz. this is a relation of the form

$$(\dagger\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0,$$

such that it is satisfied by the four sets of values $u = \pm i, v = \pm i$, and therefore in particular by the values $u = v = i$ and $u = v = -i$.

Hence, considering the intersections of the curve by the arbitrary line, the values of (u, v) are given by the two equations

$$(*\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0, \quad (\dagger\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0;$$

these, regarding for a moment u, v as ordinary rectangular coordinates, represent each of them a quartic curve having two dps. at infinity on the axes $u = 0, v = 0$ respectively: each of these points reckons therefore as 4 intersections, and the number of the remaining intersections therefore is $4 \cdot 4 - 2 \cdot 4 = 8$. But, by what precedes, the two quartic curves have also in common the points $u = v = i$ and $u = v = -i$; and rejecting these, there remain $8 - 2 = 6$ intersections.

The conclusion is, that the curve is a sextic curve of deficiency 1, that is, having 9 dps. The reasoning may be presented under a slightly different form as follows: regarding u, v as coordinates, we have the curve $(*\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0$, a binodal quartic curve, and having therefore the deficiency 1; the curve passes, as above-mentioned, through the points $u = v = i$ and $u = v = -i$. The required curve is obtained as a transformation of the quartic curve by formulae of the form $x : y : z (= 1) = P : Q : R$, where P, Q , and $R \{= (1 + u^2)(1 + v^2)\}$ are quartic functions of the coordinates u, v , such that $P = 0, Q = 0, R = 0$ are each of them a quartic curve passing twice through each of the nodes and once through each of the before-mentioned points, $(u = v = i)$ and $(u = v = -i)$, of the binodal quartic curve. Hence the curve in question is a curve of the order $4 \cdot 4 - 2 \cdot 4 - 2 \cdot 1 = 6$, and having the same deficiency as the binodal quartic, that is, the deficiency is = 1.

I observe that the sextic curve does not, in general, pass through the circular points at infinity, but it intersects the line at infinity in three distinct pairs of points; one of these, or all three of them, (but not two pairs only,) may coincide with the circular points at infinity, the circular points at infinity being, in the latter case, triple points, or the curve being tricircular: this will appear presently.

To obtain the foregoing equation $(*\chi u, 1)^2(v, 1)^2 = 0$, the elimination of γ gives

$$(a \cos \alpha + b \cos \beta + d \cos \delta)^2 + (a \sin \alpha + b \sin \beta + d \sin \delta)^2 = c^2,$$

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that is

$$a^2 + b^2 - c^2 + d^2 + 2ab \cos(\alpha - \beta) + 2ad \cos(\alpha - \delta) + 2bd \cos(\beta - \delta) = 0;$$

or, substituting herein the values

$$\cos \alpha = \frac{1 - u^2}{1 + u^2}, \quad \sin \alpha = \frac{2u}{1 + u^2}, \quad \cos \beta = \frac{1 - v^2}{1 + v^2}, \quad \sin \beta = \frac{2v}{1 + v^2},$$

this is easily found to be $0 =$

	1	$2u$	u^2
1	$(a+b)^2 - 2(a+b)d \cos \delta + d^2 - c^2$	$2ad \sin \delta$	$(a-b)^2 + 2(a-b)d \cos \delta + d^2 - c^2$
$2v$	$2bd \sin \delta$	$2ab$	$2bd \sin \delta$
v^2	$(a-b)^2 - 2(a-b)d \cos \delta + d^2 - c^2$	$2ad \sin \delta$	$(a+b)^2 + 2(a+b)d \cos \delta + d^2 - c^2$

Or writing, for greater convenience, $\delta = 0$, that is, taking α, β, γ to be the inclinations of the sides a, b, c to the fixed side d , this is $0 =$

	1	$2u$	u^2
1	$(a+b-d)^2 - c^2$	0	$(a-b+d)^2 - c^2$
$2v$	0	$2ab$	0
v^2	$(a-b-d)^2 - c^2$	0	$(a+b+d)^2 - c^2$

or say this is

$$(A + Bu^2) + 8abuv + v^2(C + Du^2) = 0,$$

where, writing for shortness

$$\begin{aligned} a + d - b - c &= \lambda, & -a + b + c + d &= \lambda', \\ b + d - c - a &= \mu, & -b + c + d + a &= \mu', \\ c + d - a - b &= \nu, & -c + d + a + b &= \nu', \\ a + b + c + d &= \sigma, & -d + a + b + c &= \rho', \end{aligned}$$

then

$$A = -\nu\rho', \quad B = \lambda\mu', \quad C = \lambda'\mu, \quad D = \nu'\sigma.$$

We at once verify that the equation is satisfied by $u = v = \pm i$, viz. this will be so if only

$$A - B - C + D - 8ab = 0,$$

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and we have

$$A + D = 2(a+b)^2 + 2d^2 - 2c^2, \quad B + C = 2(a-b)^2 + 2d^2 - 2c^2;$$

whence the relation in question.

Writing $u = i$, we have

$$\{v(C - D) + 4abi\}^2 = -16a^2b^2 - (A - B)(C - D) = -\frac{1}{4}(A - B + C - D)^2,$$

whence

$$v(C - D) = \pm \frac{1}{2}i\{\mp 8ab + A - B + C - D\} = i(C - D) \quad \text{or} \quad -i(A - B);$$

so that, corresponding to $u = i$, we have the values

$$v = i, \quad v = -i \frac{A - B}{C - D};$$

and similarly, corresponding to $u = -i$, the values

$$v = -i, \quad v = i \frac{A - B}{C - D}.$$

And in like manner, corresponding to $v = i$, we have the values

$$u = i, \quad u = -i \frac{A - C}{B - D};$$

and to $v = -i$, the values

$$u = -i, \quad u = i \frac{A - C}{B - D}.$$

It is easy to show that, if $u = i + \varepsilon$, $v = i + \zeta$ are the values consecutive to $u = v = i$, then $a\varepsilon + b\zeta = 0$: in fact, substituting the foregoing values in the relation between u, v , and writing for $8ab$ its value, $= A - B - C + D$, we have

$$A + B(-1 + 2i\varepsilon) + (A - B - C + D)\{-1 + i(\varepsilon + \zeta)\} + C(-1 + 2i\zeta) + D\{1 - 2i(\varepsilon + \zeta)\} = 0,$$

which is

$$= \varepsilon(A + B - C - D) + \zeta(A - B + C - D) = 0;$$

or finally $a\varepsilon + b\zeta = 0$. And similarly, if $u = -i + \varepsilon$, $v = -i + \zeta$ are the values consecutive to $u = v = -i$, then we have the same relation $a\varepsilon + b\zeta = 0$.

The points at infinity on the sextic curve are those for which $1 + u^2$ or $1 + v^2$, or each of these, is $= 0$; viz. the values of u, v for the six points are

$$\begin{array}{llllll} u = i + \varepsilon, & -i - \varepsilon, & i, & -i, & -i \frac{A - C}{B - D}, & i \frac{A - C}{B - D}, \\ v = i + \zeta, & -i - \zeta, & -i \frac{A - B}{C - D}, & i \frac{A - B}{C - D}, & i, & -i, \end{array}$$

where, instead of $u = v = i$ and $u = v = -i$, I have written down the consecutive values of u, v , and as before ε, ζ are infinitesimals such that $a\varepsilon + b\zeta = 0$.

Suppose that the coordinates x, y of a point on the sextic curve are

$$x = a \cos \alpha + c \sin \alpha + b \cos \beta + d \sin \beta,$$

$$y = a' \cos \alpha + c' \sin \alpha + b' \cos \beta + d' \sin \beta;$$

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then, if $u = \pm(i + \varepsilon)$,

$$\cos \alpha = \frac{-i}{\varepsilon}, \quad \sin \alpha = \frac{\pm 1}{\varepsilon},$$

and similarly if $v = \pm(i + \zeta)$, then

$$\cos \beta = \frac{-i}{\zeta}, \quad \sin \beta = \frac{\pm 1}{\zeta}.$$

Hence the points at infinity of the sextic curve are as follows:

$$\begin{array}{ll} 1^\circ. & u = \pm(i + \varepsilon), \quad v \neq \pm(i + \zeta), \\ & x = \frac{-ai \pm c}{\varepsilon}, \quad y = \frac{-a'i \pm c'}{\varepsilon}, \quad \text{first pair of points;} \\ 2^\circ. & v = \pm(i + \zeta), \quad u \neq \pm(i + \varepsilon), \\ & x = \frac{-bi \pm d}{\zeta}, \quad y = \frac{-b'i \pm d'}{\zeta}, \quad \text{second pair of points;} \\ 3^\circ. & u = \pm(i + \varepsilon), \quad v = \pm(i + \zeta), \\ & x = \frac{-ai \pm c}{\varepsilon} + \frac{-bi \pm d}{\zeta}, \quad y = \frac{-a'i \pm c'}{\varepsilon} + \frac{-b'i \pm d'}{\zeta}; \\ & a\varepsilon + b\zeta = 0, \quad \text{as above, third pair of points.} \end{array}$$

which six points are in general distinct from each other, and from the circular points at infinity.

The foregoing values of x, y may be said to be “circular quoad α ,” if $a = c'$, $a' = -c$; and similarly to be “circular quoad β ,” if $b = d'$, $b' = -d$.

And we see at once that if the values are circular quoad α , then the first pair of points coincide with the circular points at infinity; and that, in like manner, if the values are circular quoad β , then the second pair of points coincide with the circular points at infinity; but if the values are circular quoad α and β respectively, then each of the three pairs of points coincides with the circular points at infinity: so that these are then triple points on the curve; or the curve is tricircular, having besides the two triple points, 3 dps.

The relation between u, v gives

$$\{v(C + Du^2) + 4abu\}^2 = 16a^2b^2 \cdot u^2 - (A + Bu^2)(C + Du^2),$$

and it thus appears that if any one of the functions A, B, C, D is $= 0$, the function under the radical sign is a mere linear function of u^2 , say it is $L + Mu^2$; introducing a new parameter θ such that

$$u = \sqrt{\frac{L}{M}} \frac{2\theta}{1 + \theta^2}, \quad \sqrt{L + Mu^2} = \sqrt{L} \frac{1 + \theta^2}{1 - \theta^2},$$

and consequently u, v are each of them a rational function of θ . Hence, when any one of the relations in question is satisfied, or say, when $a + d = b + c$, $b + d = c + a$, or $c + d = a + b$, the curve becomes unicursal: there is no diminution of the order, and the curve is consequently a unicursal sextic, or sextic with 10 dps.

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It would at first sight appear that the curve might become unicursal in a different manner; viz. it would be unicursal if

$$16a^2b^2u^2 - (A + Bu^2)(C + Du^2)$$

was a perfect square; but this is only the case when one of the four sides a, b, c, d is $= 0$. The condition in fact is

$$AD + BC - 16a^2b^2 = 2\sqrt{ABCD};$$

that is

$$\lambda\lambda'\mu\mu' - \nu\nu'\rho'\sigma - 16a^2b^2 = 2\sqrt{-\lambda\lambda'\mu\mu'\rho'\sigma};$$

where, putting for shortness $M = d^2 - a^2 - b^2 - c^2$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \lambda\lambda' &= M - 2bc + 2ca + 2ab, \\ \mu\mu' &= M + 2bc - 2ca + 2ab, \\ \nu\nu' &= M + 2bc + 2ca - 2ab, \\ -\rho'\sigma &= M - 2bc - 2ca - 2ab; \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} \lambda\lambda'\mu\mu' &= M^2 - 4b^2c^2 - 4c^2a^2 + 4a^2b^2 + 4abM + 8c^2ab, \\ -\nu\nu'\rho'\sigma &= M^2 - 4b^2c^2 - 4c^2a^2 + 4a^2b^2 - 4abM - 8c^2ab, \end{aligned}$$

and the equation thus becomes

$$M^2 - 4b^2c^2 - 4c^2a^2 - 4a^2b^2 = \sqrt{(M^2 - 4b^2c^2 - 4c^2a^2 + 4a^2b^2)^2 - 16a^2b^2(M + 2c^2)^2}.$$

viz. putting for a moment $X = M^2 - 4c^2(a^2 + b^2)$, this is

$$(X - 4a^2b^2)^2 = (X + 4a^2b^2)^2 - 16a^2b^2(M + 2c^2)^2,$$

that is

$$16a^2b^2\{X - (M + 2c^2)^2\} = 0;$$

or, substituting for X its value, the equation is

$$64a^2b^2c^2(M + a^2 + b^2 + c^2) = 0,$$

that is $a^2b^2c^2d^2 = 0$.

We may have simultaneously 1° , $a = d$, $b = c$; 2° , $b = d$, $a = c$; 3° , $c = d$, $a = b$; the three cases are really equivalent, but the results present themselves in different forms.

1° . Here $A = 0$, $B = 4a(a - b)$, $C = 0$, $D = 4a(a + b)$; the relation between u, v contains the factor u , and throwing this out, and also the constant factor $4a$, it is

$$u[(a - b) + (a + b)v^2] + 2bv = 0,$$

viz. u is given as a rational function of v .

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2° . Here $A = 0$, $B = 0$, $C = 4b(b - a)$, $D = 4b(b + a)$; the equation contains the factor v , and throwing out this and also the constant factor $4b$, the equation is

$$v[(b - a) + (b + a)u^2] + 2au = 0,$$

viz. v is given as a rational function of u .

3° . Here $A = 4a(a - c)$, $B = 0$, $C = 0$, $D = 4a(a + c)$; or, dividing by $4a$, the equation is

$$(a - c) + 2auv + (a + c)u^2v^2 = 0;$$

viz. this is

$$(uv + 1)[(a + c)uv + a - c] = 0,$$

which may be reduced to

$$(a + c)uv + a - c = 0,$$

giving u or v each a rational function of the other.

I do not discuss the theory in detail, but only remark that in each case there is a conic thrown off, and that in place of the sextic we have a unicursal (or trinodal) quartic curve.

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505.

ON THE SURFACES DIVISIBLE INTO SQUARES BY THEIR CURVES OF CURVATURE

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. iv. (1871–1873), pp. 120, 121. Read June 13, 1872.]

Professor Cayley gave an account of an investigation recently communicated by him to the Academy of Sciences at Paris. The fundamental theorem is that, if the coordinates x, y, z of a point on a surface are expressed as functions of two parameters p, q (such expressions, of course replacing the equation of the surface); and if these parameters are such that $p = \text{const.}$, $q = \text{const.}$ are the equations of the two sets of curves of curvature respectively; then (writing for shortness

$$\frac{dx}{dp} = x_1, \quad \frac{dx}{dq} = x_2, \quad \frac{d^2x}{dp^2} = x_3, \quad \frac{d^2x}{dp dq} = x_4, \quad \frac{d^2x}{dq^2} = x_5,$$

and the like for y, z), the coordinates x, y, z , considered always as functions of p, q , satisfy the equations

$$x_1x_2 + y_1y_2 + z_1z_2 = 0, \quad \begin{vmatrix} x_1 & y_1 & z_1 \\ x_2 & y_2 & z_2 \\ x_4 & y_4 & z_4 \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

The last equation is equivalent to

$$\begin{aligned}x_4 + Ax_1 + Bx_2 &= 0, \\y_4 + Ay_1 + By_2 &= 0, \\z_4 + Az_1 + Bz_2 &= 0;\end{aligned}$$

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and if in the notation of Gauss we write

$$x_1^2 + y_1^2 + z_1^2 = E, \quad x_2^2 + y_2^2 + z_2^2 = G,$$

then adding the equations multiplied by x_1, y_1, z_1 respectively, and also adding the equations multiplied by x_2, y_2, z_2 respectively, we find

$$A = -\frac{1}{2} \frac{1}{E} \frac{dE}{dq}, \quad B = -\frac{1}{2} \frac{1}{G} \frac{dG}{dp};$$

and the equations thus become

$$2x_4 - \frac{1}{E} \frac{dE}{dq} x_1 - \frac{1}{G} \frac{dG}{dp} x_2 = 0, \quad \&c. \quad \&c. \quad \&c.,$$

which, in fact, agree with the equations (10 bis) in Lamé's "Leçons sur les coordonnées curvilignes," Paris (1859), p. 89. The surface will be divisible into squares if only $E : G$ is the quotient of a function of p by a function of q , or say if

$$E = \Theta P, \quad G = \Theta Q,$$

where Θ is any function of (p, q) , but P and Q are functions of p and q respectively; we then have

$$\frac{1}{E} \frac{dE}{dq} = \frac{1}{\Theta} \frac{d\Theta}{dq}, \quad \frac{1}{G} \frac{dG}{dp} = \frac{1}{\Theta} \frac{d\Theta}{dp},$$

and the equations for x, y, z are

$$2x_4 - \frac{1}{\Theta} \frac{d\Theta}{dq} x_1 - \frac{1}{\Theta} \frac{d\Theta}{dp} x_2 = 0, \quad \&c. \quad \&c. \quad \&c.,$$

viz. x, y, z being functions of p, q such that $x_1x_2 + y_1y_2 + z_1z_2 = 0$, and which besides satisfy these equations, or say which each of them satisfy the equation

$$2u_4 - \frac{1}{\Theta} \frac{d\Theta}{dq} u_1 - \frac{1}{\Theta} \frac{d\Theta}{dp} u_2 = 0,$$

then the values of x, y, z in terms of (p, q) determine a surface which has the property in question.

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506.

ON THE MECHANICAL DESCRIPTION OF A CUBIC CURVE

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. iv. (1871-1873), pp. 175-178. Read November 14, 1872.]

If the coordinates x, y of a point on a curve are rational functions of $\sin \phi, \cos \phi, \sqrt{1 - k^2 \sin^2 \phi}$, the curve has the deficiency 1, and conversely in any curve of deficiency 1 the coordinates x, y can be thus expressed in terms of the parameter ϕ . Hence writing $\sin \theta = k \sin \phi$, the coordinates will be rational functions of $\sin \phi, \cos \phi, \cos \theta$, or say of $\sin \phi, \cos \phi, \sin \theta, \cos \theta$; and for the mechanical representation of

the relation $k \sin \phi = \sin \theta$, we require only a rod OA rotating about the fixed point O , and connected with it by a pin at A , a rod AB , the other extremity of which, B , moves in a fixed line Ox . The curve most readily obtained by such an arrangement is that described by a point C rigidly connected with the rod AB ; this is however a quartic curve (with two dps., since its deficiency is $= 1$). I first considered the cubic curve

$$xy - 1 = \sqrt{(1 - x^2)(1 - k^2 x^2)},$$

or say

$$xy - 1 = -\sqrt{(1 - x^2)(1 - k^2 x^2)};$$

writing herein $x = \sin \phi$, and as before $k \sin \phi = \sin \theta$, we have then $y \sin \phi = 1 - \cos \theta \cos \phi$; which values may be written

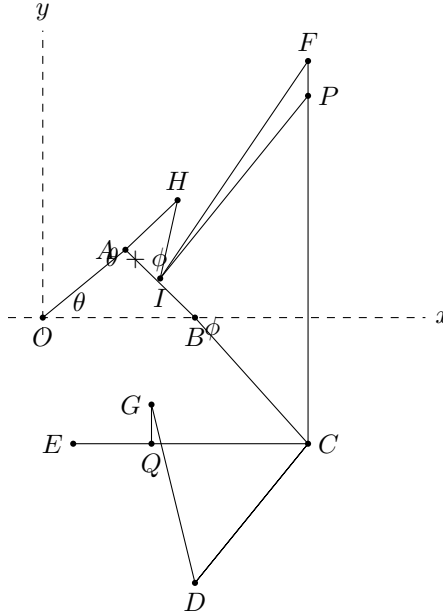
$$x = \sin \phi, \quad y = \frac{1 - \cos(\theta + \phi)}{\sin \phi} - \sin \theta.$$

I found, however, that this was not the cubic curve most easily constructed; and I ultimately devised a mechanical arrangement consisting of

1. Rod OH , and connected with it by a pin at H , rod HI .¹

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2. Square ACD , and connected with it by a pin at D , rod DG .
3. Square ECF ; the two squares being connected by a pin at C .
4. Rod IJ .



The rod OH rotates about a pin at O ; taking $HA = HI$, there is a pin at A connecting a fixed point of this rod with the extremity A of the square ACD : the fixed point B of this square moves along the line Ox . There is a pin at I connecting the extremities of the rods HI, IJ ; and this slides along the leg AC of the square ACD , the rod IJ being always at right angles thereto: finally the legs of the square ECF are always parallel to Ox, Oy , and the rod DG at right angles to EC . I have omitted from the description the parallel-motion rods or other arrangements necessary for giving

¹There was a mechanical convenience in this, but observe that producing OH to meet IP in I' , the single straight rod OHI' might have been made use of.

these fixed directions to the rod IJ , the square ECF , and the rod DG . It will be seen that the angles AOB, ABO are variable angles connected by an equation of the form above referred to; and that the lines IJ, CF determine by their intersection the point P ; and the lines CE, DG determine by their intersection the point Q ; the curve about to be considered is that determined by the relative motion of P in regard to Q ; or say the curve the coordinates of a point of which are

$$x = QC, \quad y = CP.$$

I write

$$\begin{aligned} \angle AOB &= \theta, & \angle ABO &= \phi, \\ OA &= a, & AB &= b, & AC &= c, & CD &= d, & AH &= HI = \frac{1}{2}h. \end{aligned}$$

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We then have $a \sin \theta = b \sin \phi$; and moreover the length AI being $= h \cos(\theta + \phi)$, and therefore $IC = c - h \cos(\theta + \phi)$, we have

$$y = CP = \frac{c - h \cos(\theta + \phi)}{\sin \phi}, \quad x = QC = d \sin \phi;$$

whence also

$$xy = d\{c - h \cos(\theta + \phi)\};$$

or we have

$$xy = d \left\{ c - h \sqrt{1 - \frac{x^2}{d^2}} \sqrt{1 - \frac{b^2 x^2}{a^2 d^2}} + h \frac{b x^2}{a d^2} \right\},$$

that is

$$x \left(y - \frac{bh}{ad} x \right) - cd = -dh \sqrt{1 - \frac{x^2}{d^2}} \sqrt{1 - \frac{b^2 x^2}{a^2 d^2}} :$$

or rationalising and reducing, this is

$$x^2 y^2 - \frac{2bh}{ad} x^3 y - 2cdxy \left\{ 2 \frac{b}{a} ch + h^2 \left(1 + \frac{b^2}{a^2} \right) \right\} x^2 d^2 (c^2 - h^2) = 0,$$

a quartic curve with two dps.

In the particular case $a = b$, the relation between θ, ϕ is simply $\theta = \phi$; the curve should become unicursal.

Writing in the equation $\frac{b}{a} = 1$, the equation takes the form

$$\left\{ x \left(y - \frac{2h}{d} x \right) - d(c - h) \right\} \{ xy - d(c + h) \} = 0;$$

the second factor is extraneous, and the curve is the hyperbola

$$x \left(y - \frac{2h}{d} x \right) - d(c - h) = 0,$$

as at once appears from the foregoing irrational form of the equation.

In the particular case $h = c$, the equation contains the factor x , and omitting this it becomes

$$x \left(y^2 - \frac{2bc}{ad} x^2 \right) - 2cdyc \left(1 + \frac{b}{a} \right)^2 x = 0;$$

viz. we have here a cubic curve with three real asymptotes meeting in a point which is also the centre of the curve.

If simultaneously $a = b$ and $h = c$, then the equation is

$$x \left(y - \frac{2c}{d}x \right) (xy - 2cd) = 0,$$

the actual locus being in this case the line $y - \frac{2c}{d}x = 0$.

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Writing $h = c$, and for greater convenience $h = c = d = 1$; also to fix the ideas supposing $b < a$, and writing $\frac{b}{a} = k, = \sin \lambda$, then we have

$$\sin \theta = k \sin \phi, \quad x = \sin \phi, \quad y = \frac{1 - \cos(\theta + \phi)}{\sin \phi};$$

that is

$$xy = 1 - \sqrt{1 - x^2} \sqrt{1 - k^2 x^2} + kx^2,$$

giving the rationalised equation

$$x(y^2 - 2kx^2) - 2y + 4x = 0;$$

the angle ϕ may be anything whatever, but θ varies between the limits $\pm \lambda$, the simultaneous values of these angles and of the coordinates being

$\phi = 0$	$\theta = 0$	$x = 0$	$y = 0$
$\phi = 90^\circ$	$\theta = \lambda$	$x = 1$	$y = 1 + \sin \lambda$
$\phi = 180^\circ$	$\theta = 0$	$x = 0$	$y = \pm \infty$
$\phi = 270^\circ$	$\theta = -\lambda$	$x = -1$	$y = -(1 + \sin \lambda)$
$\phi = 360^\circ$	$\theta = 0$	$x = 0$	$y = 0$

and it thus appears that the mechanism gives the continuous branch which belongs to the asymptote $x = 0$ of the cubic curve; the other two branches belong to

$$x = \sin \phi, \quad y = \frac{1 + \cos(\theta + \phi)}{\sin \phi},$$

which would require a slight alteration in the arrangement of the mechanism.

I remark that if AH, HI had been unequal, then writing $\angle HIA = \chi$, this would be connected with $\theta + \phi$ by an equation of the form

$$\sin(\theta + \phi) = m \sin \chi,$$

and the coordinates x, y would be rational functions of the sines and cosines of θ, ϕ, χ ; the deficiency is in this case > 1 .

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507.

ON THE MECHANICAL DESCRIPTION OF CERTAIN QUARTIC CURVES BY A MODIFIED OVAL CHUCK

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. iv. (1871–1873), pp. 186–190. Read December 12, 1872.]

The geometrical principle of the oval chuck is the well-known one that if a plane move in such manner that two lines Ox, Oy , fixed in the plane and moveable with it, pass through two fixed points A, B , respectively, then any fixed point P traces out on the plane an ellipse. The point A

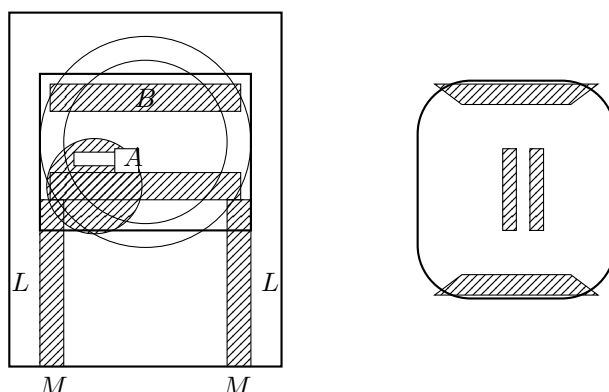
is on the (geometrical) axis of the mandril; there is connected with the head a guide-ring moving horizontally; the point B is the centre of the guide-ring, this being a ring connected with the head, moveable horizontally at right angles to the axis in such wise that the distance AB of the two centres is adjustable to any given value; the fixed point P is the tool, which practically is held on the level of the axis, that is, at a point in the line AB . The guide-ring remains fixed during the motion of the lathe.

It occurred to me that a chuck applicable to ornamental turning might be constructed by giving to the guide-ring a reciprocating motion synchronous with the rotation of the mandril; viz. for this purpose it is only necessary to affix to the axis of the mandril an eccentric, working in a frame attached to the guide-ring so as to move the centre B of the guide-ring backwards and forwards along the line AB : the curve is thus that described by the fixed point P upon a plane moving in such manner that the lines Ox, Oy pass always through the points A, B respectively; the former of these being a fixed point, the latter of them a point moving according to determinate law backwards and forwards along a fixed line through A .

The plan is carried out in a drawing apparatus which I have had constructed in wood, the axis being here vertical instead of horizontal, and the details of course different from what they would be for a lathe.

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The apparatus consists of a piece of inch-board, about 10 inches long by 7 inches broad, pierced with a circular hole of 1 inch diameter for a vertical axis: the edges of the board serve as guides for the frame L , which carries the guide-ring, and resting on the board we have the frame M , itself guided by the frame L : the two frames move independently of each other, but they can be clamped together; the axis has



upon it a square nut, the sides of which work in the slot of an eccentric, the throw of this being adjustable by means of a screw passing through the nut and axis, and there is above the eccentric a square nut shown in the figure. This is capable of rotation round the axis, so that two of its sides may be placed either parallel with or inclined to the sides of the slot; but I fix it with two sides parallel to those of the slot by means of a screw run into the axis. The upper surfaces of the last-mentioned nut and of the guide-ring are flush with each other; and we then have a table or bed having, on its under-surface, guides which work on the outer edges of the guide-ring and on two edges of the nut. It will be observed that the bed may be placed in two different positions, viz. the guides may work on either pair of edges of the nut, those which are parallel to the sides of the slot, or those which are at right angles to it.

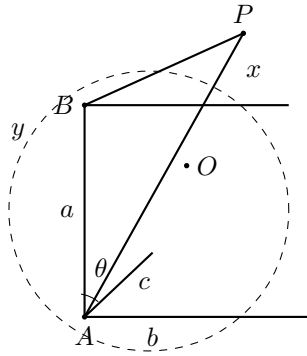
Supposing the bed placed as above upon the guide-ring and nut, then if the frames L and M are disconnected, and the former of them is fixed, the frame M will, on rotation of the axis, be carried backwards and forwards by the eccentric, but this will in no wise affect the motion of the bed; the arrangement is then equivalent to the oval chuck, and a pencil fixed above the bed in any given position will trace out upon it an ellipse. If, however, the frame L , instead of being fixed, is clamped

to the frame M , then the two frames, and therefore the guide-ring, are carried backwards and forwards by the eccentric, and the curve traced out by the pencil is no longer an ellipse; it is, as I proceed to show, a special form of trinodal quartic; viz. there is a tacnode (= two nodes) at infinity, and a third node, which may be a crunode, cusp, or acnode. In the last-mentioned case, the acnode or conjugate point is, as usual, not exhibited by the mechanical description, and the curve has no visible singularity.

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Let the coordinates of the fixed point P , referred to axes through A , the first of them perpendicular to, and the second coincident with, AB , be b, c ; let the distance AB be $= a$; and let θ denote the angle BAO : then, if x, y are the coordinates of P referred to the origin O and axes Ox, Oy , we have

$$x + a \cos \theta = b \sin \theta + c \cos \theta, \quad y = -b \cos \theta + c \sin \theta,$$



which, if a be constant, gives a quadric equation, or the curve is an ellipse; and, in particular, if $b = 0$, that is if the point P is on the line AB , then we have

$$x = (c - a) \cos \theta, \quad y = c \sin \theta,$$

or the curve is

$$\frac{x^2}{(c - a)^2} + \frac{y^2}{c^2} = 1.$$

But if a is a given function of θ , then the equation is still found by eliminating θ between the two equations for x and y . In particular, if the distance AB is given as the perpendicular upon the tangent of a circle, as shown in the figure, then if k be the radius AC of this circle, and λ the inclination of AC to Ax (k and λ being taken to be constants), we have

$$a = k \cos(\theta + \lambda),$$

and the equations are

$$x = b \sin \theta + \{c - k \cos(\theta + \lambda)\} \cos \theta, \quad y = -b \cos \theta + c \sin \theta.$$

The elimination is nearly the same as if b were $= 0$; viz. we may determine γ, α in such wise that

$$\begin{aligned} b \sin \theta + c \cos \theta &= \gamma \cos(\theta + \alpha), = \gamma \cos \phi \text{ suppose,} \\ -b \cos \theta + c \sin \theta &= \gamma \sin(\theta + \alpha), = \gamma \sin \phi; \end{aligned}$$

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and then

$$x = \gamma \cos \phi - k \cos(\phi + \lambda - \alpha) \cos(\phi - \alpha), \quad y = \gamma \sin \phi.$$

I will, for greater simplicity, at once write $b = 0$: the equations thus are

$$x = (c - k \cos \theta \cos \lambda + k \sin \theta \sin \lambda) \cos \theta, \quad y = c \sin \theta;$$

or say the first is

$$x = (c + k \sin \theta \sin \lambda) \cos \theta - k \cos^2 \theta \cos \lambda;$$

whence we have

$$x + \frac{k \cos \lambda}{c^2}(c^2 - y^2) = \left(c + \frac{ky}{c} \sin \lambda\right) \frac{1}{c} \sqrt{c^2 - y^2},$$

that is

$$c^2 x + k \cos \lambda (c^2 - y^2) = (c^2 + ky \sin \lambda) \sqrt{c^2 - y^2},$$

an equation which will assume a more simple form if either $\lambda = 0$ or $\lambda = 90^\circ$; that is, if in the apparatus the nut-sides which guide the bed are either at right angles, or parallel, to the sides of the slot.

Taking the general case, and writing for convenience $\cos \theta = \xi$, $\sin \theta = \eta$, the curve is given by equations of the form

$$x = (\xi, \eta, 1)^2, \quad y = (\xi, \eta, 1)^2, \quad \xi^2 + \eta^2 = 1;$$

viz. the elimination of ξ, η from these equations leads to the equation of the curve. The points of the curve have thus a $(1, 1)$ correspondence with those of the circle $\xi^2 + \eta^2 = 1$; or, the circle being unicursal, the curve is also unicursal. Moreover, considering the intersections of the curve with an arbitrary line $ax + by + c = 0$, the points of intersection correspond to the points of intersection of the circle by the quadric

$$a(\xi, \eta, 1)^2 + b(\xi, \eta, 1)^2 + c = 0;$$

viz. there are four points of intersection, or the curve is a quartic, and hence it is a binodal quartic. But it is a binodal quartic of a special form: to show this more clearly, I introduce for homogeneity the coordinates z, ζ , so that the foregoing equations become

$$x : y : z = (\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 : (\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 : \zeta^2, \quad \text{where } \xi^2 + \eta^2 - \zeta^2 = 0;$$

the curve corresponding to these equations is, as just seen, a binodal quartic. But in the case in hand the form is the more special one,

$$x : y : z = (\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 : \xi \zeta : \zeta^2, \quad \text{where } \xi^2 + \eta^2 - \zeta^2 = 0.$$

The intersections by the arbitrary line $ax + by + cz = 0$ are the points corresponding to the intersections of the circle $\xi^2 + \eta^2 - \zeta^2 = 0$ by the quadric

$$a(\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 + b\xi\zeta + c\zeta^2 = 0,$$

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giving four intersections. But the intersections by the line $by + cz = 0$ (that is, by any line through the point $y = 0, z = 0$) are obtained from the equation $b\xi\zeta + c\zeta^2 = 0$; viz. this breaks up into $b\xi + c\zeta = 0$, $\zeta = 0$, and the last factor combined with the equation of the circle gives $\zeta = 0$, $\xi^2 + \eta^2 = 0$, the two circular points at infinity, corresponding each to the point $y = 0, z = 0$: the other factor gives points corresponding to two variable points on the curve; that is, a line through the point $y = 0, z = 0$ meets the curve in this point twice and in two other points. Again, making $b = 0$, or taking the line to be the line at infinity $z = 0$, the equations then are $\zeta = 0$, $\xi^2 + \eta^2 = 0$; viz. we then have the circular points at infinity each twice, corresponding to the point $y = 0, z = 0$ four times, and no other point; that is, the line $z = 0$ meets the curve in the point $y = 0, z = 0$ four times. We thus see that the curve has at $y = 0, z = 0$, that is at infinity on the line $y = 0$, a tacnode (counting as two nodes), the tangent at this point being the line at infinity $z = 0$. The curve being trinodal has of course one other node.

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ON GEODESIC LINES, IN PARTICULAR THOSE OF A QUADRIC SURFACE

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. iv. (1871–1873), pp. 191–211. Read December 12, 1872.]

The present Memoir contains an investigation of the differential equation (of the second order) of the geodesic lines on a surface, the coordinates of a point on the surface being regarded as given functions of two parameters p, q , and researches in connection therewith; a deduction of Jacobi's differential equation of the first order in the case of a quadric surface, the parameters p, q being those which determine the two sets of curves of curvature; formulae where the parameters are those which determine the two right lines through the surface; and a discussion of the forms of the geodesic lines in the two cases of an ellipsoid and a skew hyperboloid respectively.

Preliminary Formulae.

1. I call to mind the fundamental formulae in the Memoir by Gauss, “Disquisitiones generales circa superficies curvas,” *Comm. Gott. recent.*, t. vi., 1827, (reprinted as an Appendix in Liouville's edition of Monge,) together with some that I have added to them. The coordinates x, y, z of a point on a surface are regarded as given functions of two parameters p, q , these expressions of x, y, z in effect determining the equation of the surface, and we have

$$\begin{aligned} dx + \frac{1}{2}d^2x &= a dp + a' dq + \frac{1}{2}(\alpha dp^2 + 2\alpha' dp dq + \alpha'' dq^2), \\ dy + \frac{1}{2}d^2y &= b dp + b' dq + \frac{1}{2}(\beta dp^2 + 2\beta' dp dq + \beta'' dq^2), \\ dz + \frac{1}{2}d^2z &= c dp + c' dq + \frac{1}{2}(\gamma dp^2 + 2\gamma' dp dq + \gamma'' dq^2), \\ A, B, C &= bc' - b'c, \quad ca' - c'a, \quad ab' - a'b; \end{aligned}$$

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whence differential equation of surface is

$$Adx + Bdy + Cdz = 0.$$

Also

$$E, F, G = a^2 + b^2 + c^2, \quad aa' + bb' + cc', \quad a'^2 + b'^2 + c'^2;$$

so that element of length on the surface is given by

$$dx^2 + dy^2 + dz^2 = E dp^2 + 2F dp dq + G dq^2;$$

or, as I write it,

$$= (E, F, G)(dp, dq)^2;$$

and moreover

$$V^2 = A^2 + B^2 + C^2 = EG - F^2.$$

The equation $(E, F, G)(dp, dq)^2 = 0$ determines at each point on the surface two directions (necessarily imaginary) which are called the “circular” directions. Passing on the surface from point to point along the circular directions, we obtain two series of curves (always imaginary) which are the “circular” curves; the equation $(E, F, G)(dp, dq)^2 = 0$ is the differential equation of these curves; and if we have $E = 0, G = 0$, then this becomes $dp dq = 0$; viz. we have in this case $p = \text{const.}$ and $q = \text{const.}$ as the equations of the two sets of circular curves respectively. It is clear *a priori*, and will be shown analytically in the sequel, that the circular curves are geodesic lines.

I write also

$$E', F', G' = A\alpha + B\beta + C\gamma, \quad Aa' + B\beta' + C\gamma', \quad Aa'' + B\beta'' + C\gamma'',$$

or, what is the same thing, E', F', G' represent the determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} a & b & c \\ a' & b' & c' \\ \alpha & \beta & \gamma \end{vmatrix}, \quad \begin{vmatrix} a & b & c \\ a' & b' & c' \\ \alpha' & \beta' & \gamma' \end{vmatrix}, \quad \begin{vmatrix} a & b & c \\ a' & b' & c' \\ \alpha'' & \beta'' & \gamma'' \end{vmatrix},$$

respectively, (these last symbols do not occur in Gauss). [They are the D, D', D'' of Gauss.]

2. The radius of curvature of normal section corresponding to direction $dp : dq$ is given by

$$\frac{\rho}{V} = \frac{(E, F, G)(dp, dq)^2}{(E', F', G')(dp, dq)^2};$$

whence it appears that the directions of the inflexional or chief tangents (the *Haupttangenten*) are determined by the equation

$$(E', F', G')(dp, dq)^2 = 0.$$

The directions in question are imaginary on a surface such as the ellipsoid where the curvatures are in the same direction, but on a concavo-convex surface they are real; and in particular on the hyperboloid they coincide with the directions of the generating lines. We may on any surface pass from point to point along the chief directions; we have thus on the surface two sets of curves which are the chief curves;

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the differential equation of these is $(E', F', G')(dp, dq)^2 = 0$; and in particular if $E' = 0, G' = 0$, then this becomes $dp dq = 0$, or we have $p = \text{const.}, q = \text{const.}$ for the equations of the two sets of chief curves respectively. On the hyperboloid the chief curves are the two sets of generating lines. The chief curves are not in general geodesic lines, but on the hyperboloid, quà straight lines, they are, it is clear, geodesic lines.

3. The directions of the curves of curvature, or the principal tangents, and the corresponding values of the radius of curvature are determined by

$$\frac{\rho}{V} = \frac{Edp + Fdq}{E'dp + F'dq} = \frac{Fdp + Gdq}{F'dp + G'dq};$$

or, what is the same thing, these directions are determined by the equation

$$\begin{vmatrix} dq^2 & -dq dp & dp^2 \\ E & F & G \\ E' & F' & G' \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

The same equations may be written

$$-dq : dp = \frac{\rho E' - VE}{\rho F' - VF} = \frac{\rho F' - VF}{\rho G' - VG};$$

that is the principal radii of curvature are determined by the equation

$$\rho^2(E'G' - F'^2) - \rho V(EG' + E'G - 2FF') + V^2(EG - F^2) = 0,$$

(last term is $= V^4$, but it is better to retain the original form): and then, ρ being either root, the last preceding equations give the direction of the curve of curvature corresponding to the given value of the radius of curvature.

If $p = \text{const.}$, $q = \text{const.}$ are the equations of the two systems of curves of curvature respectively, then the quadric equation in (dp, dq) must become $dp dq = 0$; this will be so if $F = 0$, $F' = 0$; and we thus have these equations, viz. written at full length they are

$$d_p x d_q x + d_p y d_q y + d_p z d_q z = 0,$$

$$\begin{vmatrix} d_p x & d_p y & d_p z \\ d_q x & d_q y & d_q z \\ d_p d_q x & d_p d_q y & d_p d_q z \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

as the conditions in order that $p = \text{const.}$, $q = \text{const.}$ may be the two systems of curves of curvature. The former of these equations merely expresses that the two sets of curves always intersect at right angles.

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General Theory of the Geodesic Lines on a Surface.

4. I now proceed to investigate the theory of geodesic lines on a surface, the surface being determined as above by means of given expressions of the coordinates x, y, z in terms of the parameters p, q .

The differential equation obtained by Gauss for the geodesic lines is in a form not symmetrical in regard to the two variables; viz. his equation is

$$\frac{dE}{dq} dp^2 + 2 \frac{dF}{dp} dp dq + \frac{dG}{dp} dq^2 = 2 ds d \frac{E dp + F dq}{ds},$$

where, as above,

$$ds^2 = (E, F, G)(dp, dq)^2.$$

If we herein consider p, q as functions of a parameter θ , and write for shortness

$$d_\theta p, d_\theta q, d_\theta^2 p, \&c. = p', q', p'', \&c.,$$

also

$$\Omega = (E, F, G)(p', q')^2,$$

and

$$d_p E = E_1, \quad d_q E = E_2, \quad \&c.,$$

then the equation is

$$(E_1, F_1, G_1)(p', q')^2 - 2\sqrt{\Omega} \left(\frac{E p' + F q'}{\sqrt{\Omega}} \right)' = 0.$$

We have

$$\left(\frac{E p' + F q'}{\sqrt{\Omega}} \right)' = \frac{1}{\Omega \sqrt{\Omega}} (M + N),$$

where N is the part containing p'', q'' , which I will first calculate; viz. we have

$$\begin{aligned} N &= \Omega(E p'' + F q'') - (E p' + F q') \frac{1}{2} \Omega', \\ &= \Omega(E p'' + F q'') - (E p' + F q') \{ (E p' + F q') p'' + (F p' + G q') q'' \}, \\ &= p'' \{ E \Omega - (E p' + F q')^2 \} + q'' \{ F \Omega - (E p' + F q')(F p' + G q') \}; \end{aligned}$$

or substituting for Ω its value, this is

$$= p''(EG - F^2)q'^2 - q''(EG - F^2)p'q', = -q'(EG - F^2)(p'q'' - p''q');$$

wherefore

$$\left(\frac{E p' + F q'}{\sqrt{\Omega}} \right)' = \frac{1}{\Omega \sqrt{\Omega}} \{ M - q'(EG - F^2)(p'q'' - p''q') \},$$

and the equation becomes

$$\Omega(E_1 p'^2 + 2F_1 p' q' + G_1 q'^2) - 2M + 2q'(EG - F^2)(p' q'' - p'' q') = 0;$$

whence we foresee that the whole equation must divide by q' .

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5. We have

$$\begin{aligned} M &= (p' dE + q' dF) \Omega - (Ep' + Fq')(\tfrac{1}{2} p'^2 dE + p' q' dF + \tfrac{1}{2} q'^2 dG), \\ &= dE \{ p' \Omega - \tfrac{1}{2} p'^2 (Ep' + Fq') \} \\ &\quad + dF \{ q' \Omega - p' q' (Ep' + Fq') \} \\ &\quad + dG \{ -\tfrac{1}{2} q'^2 (Ep' + Fq') \}, \end{aligned}$$

or say

$$\begin{aligned} 2M &= dE[p'^2(p'E + q'F) + 2p'q'(p'F + q'G)] \\ &\quad + dF[2q'^2(p'F + q'G)] \\ &\quad + dG[-q'^2(p'E + q'F)], \\ &= (E_1 p' + E_2 q')[p'^2(Ep' + Fq') + 2p'q'(Fp' + Gq')] \\ &\quad + (F_1 p' + F_2 q')[2q'^2(Fp' + Gq')] \\ &\quad + (G_1 p' + G_2 q')[-q'^2(Ep' + Fq')]. \end{aligned}$$

The term in p'^4 is $EE_1 p'^4$, which is also the term in p'^4 of $\Omega(E_1 p'^2 + 2F_1 p' q' + G_1 q'^2)$; whence $\Omega(E_1 p'^2 + 2F_1 p' q' + G_1 q'^2) - 2M$ divides by q' .

Proceeding to the reduction:

Term in E_1 is

$$E_1 \cdot p'^2 \Omega - p'^3 (Ep' + Fq') - 2p'^2 q' (Fp' + Gq') = E_1 \cdot (-p'^2 q' (Fp' + Gq'));$$

term in F_1 is

$$F_1 \cdot 2p' q' \Omega - 2p' q'^2 (Fp' + Gq') = F_1 \cdot 2p'^2 q' (Ep' + Fq');$$

term in G_1 is

$$G_1 \cdot q'^2 \Omega + p' q'^2 (Ep' + Fq') = G_1 \{ 2p' q'^2 (Ep' + Fq') + q'^3 (Fp' + Gq') \}.$$

6. The remaining terms in E_2, F_2, G_2 require no reduction, and the result is

$$\begin{aligned} &E_1 \{ -p'^2 (Fp' + Gq') \} - E_2 \{ p'^2 (Ep' + Fq') + 2p' q' (Fp' + Gq') \} \\ &+ F_1 \{ 2p'^2 (Ep' + Fq') \} - F_2 \{ 2q'^2 (Fp' + Gq') \} \\ &+ G_1 \{ 2p' q' (Ep' + Fq') + q'^2 (Fp' + Gq') \} - G_2 \{ -q'^2 (Ep' + Fq') \} \\ &+ 2(EG - F^2)(p' q'' - p'' q') = 0, \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} &(Ep' + Fq') \{ (2F_1 - E_2) p'^2 + 2G_1 p' q' + G_2 q'^2 \} \\ &- (Fp' + Gq') \{ E_1 p'^2 + 2E_2 p' q' + (2F_2 - G_1) q'^2 \} \\ &+ 2(EG - F^2)(p' q'' - p'' q') = 0, \end{aligned}$$

which is the required differential equation of the second order: the independent variable has been taken to be the arbitrary quantity θ ; but taking $\theta = p$, or q , say $\theta = p$, we have $p' = 1$, $p'' = 0$, and the equation then contains (besides p and q) only q'' and q' , that is, $d_p^2 q$ and $d_p q$, and is therefore a differential relation between p and q .

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7. Instead of starting, as above, from the equation given by Gauss, we may use the geometrical property that at each point of a geodesic line the osculating plane passes through the normal of the surface.

Considering, as above, p, q as functions of a variable θ , then, θ becoming $\theta + d\theta$, the new values of p, q are

$$p + p'd\theta + \frac{1}{2}p''d\theta^2, \quad q + q'd\theta + \frac{1}{2}q''d\theta^2;$$

and that of x is

$$x + a(p'd\theta + \frac{1}{2}p''d\theta^2) + a'(q'd\theta + \frac{1}{2}q''d\theta^2) + \frac{1}{2}(\alpha p'^2 + 2\alpha'p'q' + \alpha''q'^2)d\theta^2;$$

or calling this $x + x'd\theta + \frac{1}{2}x''d\theta^2$, we have

$$x' = ap' + a'q', \quad x'' = ap'' + a'q'' + \alpha p'^2 + 2\alpha'p'q' + \alpha''q'^2,$$

and so

$$\begin{aligned} y' &= bp' + b'q', & y'' &= bp'' + b'q'' + \beta p'^2 + 2\beta'p'q' + \beta''q'^2, \\ z' &= cp' + c'q', & z'' &= cp'' + c'q'' + \gamma p'^2 + 2\gamma'p'q' + \gamma''q'^2. \end{aligned}$$

The condition in question is expressed by the equation

$$\begin{vmatrix} A & B & C \\ x' & y' & z' \\ x'' & y'' & z'' \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

that is

$$\begin{aligned} & \begin{vmatrix} A & B & C \\ ap' + a'q' & bp' + b'q' & cp' + c'q' \\ ap'' + a'q'' & bp'' + b'q'' & cp'' + c'q'' \end{vmatrix} \\ & + \begin{vmatrix} A & B & C \\ ap' + a'q' & bp' + b'q' & cp' + c'q' \\ \alpha p'^2 + 2\alpha'p'q' + \alpha''q'^2 & \beta p'^2 + 2\beta'p'q' + \beta''q'^2 & \gamma p'^2 + 2\gamma'p'q' + \gamma''q'^2 \end{vmatrix} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

8. The first determinant is the sum of three terms such as $A(bc' - b'c)(p'q'' - p''q')$; viz. this is $A^2(p'q'' - p''q')$, or the determinant is

$$(A^2 + B^2 + C^2)(p'q'' - p''q') = (EG - F^2)(p'q'' - p''q').$$

The second determinant is the sum of three terms such as

$$(\alpha p'^2 + 2\alpha'p'q' + \alpha''q'^2)[B(cp' + c'q') - C(bp' + b'q')],$$

where the factor in [] is

$$p'[c(ca' - c'a) - b(ab' - a'b)] + q'[c'(ca' - c'a) - b'(ab' - a'b)],$$

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which is $= p'(a'E - aF) + q'(a'F - aG)$. We have thus the second determinant, and the equation becomes

$$\begin{aligned} & (EG - F^2)(p'q'' - p''q') \\ & + (\alpha p'^2 + 2\alpha'p'q' + \alpha''q'^2)\{p'(a'E - aF) + q'(a'F - aG)\} \\ & + (\beta p'^2 + 2\beta'p'q' + \beta''q'^2)\{p'(b'E - bF) + q'(b'F - bG)\} \\ & + (\gamma p'^2 + 2\gamma'p'q' + \gamma''q'^2)\{p'(c'E - cF) + q'(c'F - cG)\} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

an equation of the same form as that previously obtained, and which can be without difficulty identified therewith.

The Circular Curves are Geodesics.

9. I proceed to show that the circular curves are geodesics; viz. that an integral of the geodesic equation is

$$(E, F, G)(p', q')^2 = 0.$$

Starting from this equation, we have

$$\begin{aligned} & 2\{(Ep' + Fq')p'' + (Fp' + Gq')q''\} \\ & + (E_1p' + E_2q')p'^2 + 2(F_1p' + F_2q')p'q' + (G_1p' + G_2q')q'^2 = 0. \end{aligned}$$

Now the equation, writing therein $Ep' + Fq' = \lambda q'$, gives $Fp' + Gq' = -\lambda p'$: these equations may be written

$$Ep' + (F - \lambda)q' = 0, \quad (F + \lambda)p' + Gq' = 0,$$

the value of λ being therefore $-\lambda^2 = EG - F^2$. The result just obtained thus becomes

$$\begin{aligned} & 2\lambda(p''q' - p'q'') \\ & + [(E_1p' + E_2q')p' + (F_1p' + F_2q')q'] \cdot \left(-\frac{1}{\lambda}\right) (Fp' + Gq') \\ & + [(F_1p' + F_2q')p' + (G_1p' + G_2q')q'] \cdot \frac{1}{\lambda} (Ep' + Fq'), \end{aligned}$$

that is

$$\begin{aligned} & 2(EG - F^2)(p'q'' - p''q') \\ & - (Fp' + Gq')[E_1p'^2 + (E_2 + F_1)p'q' + F_2q'^2] \\ & + (Ep' + Fq')[F_1p'^2 + (F_2 + G_1)p'q' + G_2q'^2] = 0; \end{aligned}$$

or what is the same thing, adding hereto the zero value

$$\Delta(E, F, G)(p', q')^2 = (Fp' + Gq')\Delta q' + (Ep' + Fq')\Delta p',$$

where Δ is arbitrary, the equation is

$$\begin{aligned} & 2(EG - F^2)(p'q'' - p''q') \\ & + (Ep' + Fq')[F_1p'^2 + (F_2 + G_1)p'q' + G_2q'^2 + \Delta p'] \\ & - (Fp' + Gq')[E_1p'^2 + (E_2 + F_1)p'q' + F_2q'^2 - \Delta q'] = 0; \end{aligned}$$

viz. taking $\Delta = (F_1 - E_2)p' + (G_1 - F_2)q'$, this agrees with the geodesic equation.

The foregoing integral, $(E, F, G)(p', q')^2 = 0$, is, I believe, a particular, not a singular, solution of the geodesic equation.

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The Chief Lines are not in general Geodesics.

10. That the chief lines are not in general geodesics appears most readily as follows:

To find the condition in order that $p = \text{const.}$ may be a geodesic, we write in the geodesic equation $p' = 0, p'' = 0$: the equation thus becomes

$$Fq' \cdot G_2q'^2 - Gq'(2F_2 - G_1)q'^2 = 0;$$

that is we have

$$FG_2 - 2F_2G + GG_1 = 0$$

as the condition in order that $p = \text{const.}$ may be a geodesic: the condition that it may be a chief curve is $G' = 0$, which is a different condition.

We have of course, in like manner,

$$2EF_1 - E_1F - EE_2 = 0$$

as the condition in order that $q = \text{const.}$ may be a geodesic; and $E' = 0$ as the condition that this may be a chief curve. If $p = \text{const.}, q = \text{const.}$ are each of them at once a geodesic and a chief curve, then the four equations must all be satisfied, viz. we must have

$$FG_2 - 2F_2G + GG_1 = 0, \quad 2EF_1 - E_1F - EE_2 = 0, \quad G' = 0, \quad E' = 0.$$

Special Form of the Geodesic Equation.

11. In the case where the curves $p = \text{const.}, q = \text{const.}$ intersect at right angles (and in particular when these are the curves of curvature), we have $F = 0$; whence also $F_1 = 0, F_2 = 0$; and the geodesic equation assumes the more simple form,

$$\begin{aligned} & Ep'(-E_2p'^2 + 2G_1p'q' + G_2q'^2) \\ & - Gq'(E_1p'^2 + 2E_2p'q' - G_1q'^2) \\ & + 2EG(p'q'' - p''q') = 0. \end{aligned}$$

[11a. In the case of a surface of revolution we have

$$x = p \cos q, \quad y = p \sin q, \quad z = P;$$

E is of the form $1 + P'^2$, $P' = d_p P$, where P is a function of p only, and we have

$$ds^2 = (1 + P'^2)dp^2 + p^2dq^2,$$

that is

$$E = 1 + P'^2, \quad E_1 = 2P'P'', \quad E_2 = 0, \quad F = 0, \quad G = p^2, \quad G_1 = 2p, \quad G_2 = 0;$$

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hence the differential equation is

$$(1 + P'^2)\{p^2(p'q'' - p''q') + 2pp'^2q'\} - p^2p'^2q'P'P'' + p^3q'^3 = 0;$$

this has an integral

$$\frac{(1 + P'^2)p'^2}{p^4q'^2} + \frac{1}{p^2} = \frac{1}{C^2},$$

or say

$$C^2s'^2 = p^4q'^2$$

where

$$s'^2 = (1 + P'^2)p'^2 + p^2q'^2.$$

Writing here ρ, ψ for p, q , where ρ is the distance of the point from the axis, and ψ is the longitude reckoned from an arbitrary meridian, then the equation is

$$Cds = \rho^2 d\psi,$$

which is the equation given by Legendre, *Théorie des fonctions elliptiques*, t. I. p. 361. This may also be written

$$\frac{C}{\rho} = \cos \gamma$$

if γ be the inclination of the geodesic line to the parallel of latitude.]

Geodesics on a Quadric Surface.

12. In the case of a quadric surface

$$\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} = 1,$$

writing for shortness $\alpha, \beta, \gamma = b - c, c - a, a - b$, we may express the coordinates x, y, z in terms of two parameters p, q as follows:

$$\begin{aligned} -\beta\gamma x^2 &= a(a+p)(a+q), \\ -\gamma\alpha y^2 &= b(b+p)(b+q), \\ -\alpha\beta z^2 &= c(c+p)(c+q), \end{aligned}$$

where, in fact, $p = \text{const.}, q = \text{const.}$ are the equations of the two sets of curves of curvature respectively. Writing moreover

$$P = \frac{p}{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)}, \quad Q = \frac{q}{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)},$$

we have

$$ds^2 = \frac{1}{4}(p-q)(Pdp^2 - Qdq^2),$$

that is

$$E, F, G = \frac{1}{4}(p-q)P, \quad 0, \quad \frac{1}{4}(q-p)Q;$$

and the geodesic equation becomes

$$\begin{aligned} &Pp'\{Pp'^2 - 2Qp'q' + (Q + (q-p)Q')q'^2\} \\ &+ Qq'\{P + (p-q)P'\}p'^2 - 2Pp'q' + Qq'^2\} \\ &- 2(p-q)PQ(p'q'' - p''q') = 0, \end{aligned}$$

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where P', Q' stand for $d_p P$ and $d_q Q$ respectively; viz. this is

$$\begin{aligned} &p'^3 \cdot P^2 \\ &+ p'^2 q' \cdot \{-PQ + (p-q)P'Q\} \\ &+ p'q'^2 \cdot \{-PQ + (q-p)PQ'\} \\ &+ q'^3 \cdot Q^2 \\ &- 2(p-q)PQ(p'q'' - p''q') = 0. \end{aligned}$$

13. This has a first integral,

$$p' \sqrt{\frac{P}{\theta + p}} + q' \sqrt{\frac{Q}{\theta + q}} = 0,$$

where θ is the constant of integration; or say this is

$$\theta(p'^2 P - q'^2 Q) + p'^2 q P - q'^2 p Q = 0;$$

viz. differentiating logarithmically, this gives

$$\frac{2p'p''P - 2q'q''Q + p'^3 P' - q'^3 Q'}{p'^2 P - q'^2 Q} = \frac{2p'p''qP - 2q'q''pQ + p'^2(qp'P' + q'P) - q'^2(pq'Q' + p'Q)}{p'^2 q P - q'^2 p Q},$$

which, multiplying out the denominators, is in fact the foregoing geodesic equation. To verify, consider first the part involving p'', q'' : this is

$$(2p'p''P - 2q'q''Q)(p'^2 q P - q'^2 p Q) - (2p'p''qP - 2q'q''pQ)(p'^2 P - q'^2 Q),$$

which is

$$= 2p'p''P \cdot q'^2Q(q-p) - 2q'q''Q \cdot p'^2P(q-p),$$

that is

$$= 2(q-p)PQp'q'(p''q' - p'q''),$$

or say

$$= 2(p-q)PQp'q'(p'q'' - p''q').$$

We have next the part

$$(p'^3P' - q'^3Q')(p'^2qP - q'^2pQ) - \{p'^2(qp'P' + q'P) + q'^2(pq'Q' + p'Q)\}(p'^2P - q'^2Q),$$

which is readily found to be

$$= -p'q'\{p'^3P^2 + p'^2q'(-PQ + (p-q)P'Q)p'q'^2(-PQ + (q-p)PQ') + q'^3Q^2\},$$

and the equation is thus verified.

14. We have consequently

$$dp\sqrt{\frac{p}{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)(\theta+p)}} + dq\sqrt{\frac{q}{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)(\theta+q)}} = 0,$$

involving the arbitrary constant θ as the differential equation of the first order of the geodesic lines on the quadric surface

$$\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} = 1;$$

the geodesic lines in question

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all touch the curve of curvature determined by the parameter θ , that is the curve which is the intersection of the surface by the confocal surface

$$\frac{x^2}{a+\theta} + \frac{y^2}{b+\theta} + \frac{z^2}{c+\theta} = 1.$$

15. In the particular case $\theta = \infty$, the equation becomes

$$Pdp^2 - Qdq^2 = 0,$$

that is

$$\frac{p dp^2}{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)} - \frac{q dq^2}{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)} = 0,$$

which is the differential equation of the circular curves on the surface.

16. The signification of the case $\theta = 0$ is not at first sight so obvious. Supposing that θ is first indefinitely small, and writing the equation in the form

$$\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} - 1 - \theta \left(\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} \right) + \&c. = 0,$$

we have the series of geodesics touching the (imaginary) curve of curvature, the intersection of the surface by the imaginary cone

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 0.$$

These are, in fact, the right lines on the surface: I apprehend that the intersection in question is not a proper envelope, but is the locus of nodes of the geodesics, viz. each geodesic is to be considered as a pair of lines belonging to the two sets: I do not, however, quite understand this.

17. I say that the geodesics in question are the right lines on the surface; viz. writing in the differential equation $\theta = 0$, it is to be shown that the differential equation of the right lines is

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)}} = 0,$$

or what is the same thing, that the integral of this equation represents the right lines on the surface.

Writing the equation of the surface in the form

$$\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} = 1 - \frac{z^2}{c},$$

we have at once

$$\begin{aligned}\frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} + \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} &= \sigma \left(1 + \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}} \right), \\ \frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} - \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} &= \frac{1}{\sigma} \left(1 - \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}} \right).\end{aligned}$$

[508] (σ an arbitrary parameter) as the equations of a right line on the surface; viz. considering x, y, z as denoting the foregoing functions of p and q , these two equations are forms of a single relation between p, q, σ , which relation expresses that the point (p, q) is situate on the right line determined by the parameter σ . We may from this integral equation deduce without difficulty the foregoing differential equation; viz. we have

$$\frac{dx}{\sqrt{a}} + \frac{i dy}{\sqrt{b}} = \sigma \frac{dz}{\sqrt{c}}, \quad \frac{dx}{\sqrt{a}} - \frac{i dy}{\sqrt{b}} = -\frac{1}{\sigma} \frac{dz}{\sqrt{c}},$$

or multiplying these equations,

$$\frac{dx^2}{a} + \frac{dy^2}{b} + \frac{dz^2}{c} = 0;$$

and substituting herein for dx, dy, dz their values in terms of dp and dq , we find the required equation

$$\frac{dp^2}{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)} - \frac{dq^2}{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)} = 0.$$

18. I return to the integral equation involving σ : we have to rationalise this equation, that is, obtain from it an equation containing x^2, y^2, z^2 , and then substituting for these their values in terms of p, q , we have the required relation between p, q, σ . We at once obtain

$$\left\{ 2 \left(\frac{x^2}{a} - \frac{y^2}{b} \right) - \left(\sigma^2 + \frac{1}{\sigma^2} \right) \left(1 + \frac{z^2}{c} \right) \right\}^2 - 4 \left(\sigma^2 - \frac{1}{\sigma^2} \right)^2 \frac{z^2}{c} = 0;$$

or if for greater convenience we introduce in place of σ a new parameter ϕ , determined by the equation

$$\sigma^2 + \frac{1}{\sigma^2} = \frac{2\phi}{\gamma},$$

the equation is

$$\left\{ \gamma \left(\frac{x^2}{a} - \frac{y^2}{b} \right) - \phi \left(1 + \frac{z^2}{c} \right) \right\}^2 - 4(\phi^2 - \gamma^2) \frac{z^2}{c} = 0.$$

Writing for shortness $p+q=X$, $pq=Y$, we have

$$-\beta\gamma \frac{x^2}{a} = a^2 + aX + Y, \quad -\gamma\alpha \frac{y^2}{b} = b^2 + bX + Y, \quad -\alpha\beta \frac{z^2}{c} = c^2 + cX + Y;$$

and substituting these values, the equation becomes

$$\{\beta(b^2 + bX + Y) - \alpha(a^2 + aX + Y) - \phi\gamma(\alpha\beta - c^2 - cX - Y)\}^2 + 4\alpha\beta(\phi^2 - \gamma^2)(c^2 + cX + Y) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\{\beta b^2 - \alpha a^2 - \phi\gamma(\alpha\beta - c^2) + X(\beta b - \alpha a + \phi\gamma c) + Y(\beta - \alpha + \phi\gamma)\}^2 + 4\alpha\beta(\phi^2 - \gamma^2)(c^2 + cX + Y) = 0.$$

19. This is an equation, quadric as regards p , and also as regards q , viz. it is of the form

$$\begin{aligned} & (a + 2hp + gp^2) \\ & + 2q(h + 2bp + fp^2) \\ & + q^2(g + 2fp + cp^2) = 0, \end{aligned}$$

and it leads to a differential equation

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} = 0,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} P &= (h + 2bp + fp^2)^2 - (a + 2hp + gp^2)(g + 2fp + cp^2), \\ Q &= (h + 2bq + fq^2)^2 - (a + 2hq + gq^2)(g + 2fq + cq^2); \end{aligned}$$

and upon effecting the calculation, it is found that we have

$$\begin{aligned} P &= -8\alpha^2\beta^2(\phi^2 - \gamma^2)(a + b - 2c - \phi)(a + p)(b + p)(c + p), \\ Q &= -8\alpha^2\beta^2(\phi^2 - \gamma^2)(a + b - 2c - \phi)(a + q)(b + q)(c + q), \end{aligned}$$

viz. P, Q are the same multiples of $(a + p)(b + p)(c + p)$, $(a + q)(b + q)(c + q)$ respectively; so that, omitting the common factor, or taking P, Q to represent the last-mentioned functions respectively, we have

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} = 0;$$

and since the parameter ϕ has disappeared, we see that the original equation involving ϕ is the general integral of this differential equation; viz. that the differential equation belongs to the right lines on the surface.

20. The form of the integral equation may be simplified by introducing instead of ϕ a new parameter K , connected with it by the equation

$$K = \frac{\beta b - \alpha a + \phi c}{\beta - \alpha + \phi}, \quad \phi = \frac{(\beta - \alpha)K - \beta b + \alpha a}{c - K};$$

viz. we thence deduce

$$\begin{aligned} \beta - \alpha + \phi &= -2\alpha\beta \quad (\div), \\ \beta b - \alpha a + \phi c &= -2\alpha\beta K \quad (\div), \\ \beta b^2 - \alpha a^2 - \phi(\alpha\beta - c^2) &= 2\alpha\beta(ac + bc - ab + 2cK) \quad (\div), \\ \phi + \gamma &= 2\beta(K - b) \quad (\div), \\ \phi - \gamma &= -2\alpha(K - a) \quad (\div), \end{aligned}$$

where the sign $(\div)$ is used to signify that the functions preceding it have to be divided by a denominator which in fact is $c - K$. The equation thus becomes

$$(ac + bc - ab - 2cK - KX - Y)^2 - 4(K - a)(K - b)(c^2 + cX + Y) = 0;$$

and if we moreover write

$$\nu, \mu, \lambda = abc, \quad bc + ca + ab, \quad a + b + c,$$

and instead of K introduce the parameter C , $= \lambda - K$, the equation becomes

$$\{-\mu - 2c^2 + 2cC - (\lambda - C)X - Y\}^2 + (b + c - C)(c + a - C)(c^2 + cX + Y) = 0;$$

or expanding and reducing, this is

$$\begin{aligned} &\{Y + (\lambda - C)X\}^2 \\ &\quad + Y(-2\mu + 4\lambda C - 4C^2) \\ &\quad + X(2\mu\lambda - 4\nu - 2\mu C) \\ &\quad + \mu^2 - 4\nu C = 0, \end{aligned}$$

or say

$$\begin{aligned} &\mu^2 - 4\nu C \\ &\quad + (2\mu\lambda - 4\nu - 2\mu C)(p + q) \\ &\quad + (-2\mu + 4\lambda C - 4C^2)pq \\ &\quad + (\lambda - C)^2(p^2 + q^2 + 2pq) \\ &\quad + 2(\lambda - C)pq(p + q) + p^2q^2 = 0, \end{aligned}$$

viz. this, containing the constant C , is the general integral of the differential equation

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} = 0,$$

where

$$P = (a + p)(b + p)(c + p) = \nu + \mu p + \lambda p^2 + p^3, \quad Q = (a + q)(b + q)(c + q) = \nu + \mu q + \lambda q^2 + q^3.$$

21. The constant C is connected with the parameter σ , which originally served to determine the right line, by the equation

$$\sigma + \frac{1}{\sigma} = \frac{2}{\gamma} \frac{(\beta - \alpha)(\lambda - C) - \beta b + \alpha a}{c - (\lambda - C)},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\sigma + \frac{1}{\sigma} = \frac{2}{b - c} \frac{2c^2 - a^2 - b^2 - C(2c - a - b)}{C - a - b}.$$

Reverting to the equation between p, q, ϕ , I remark that if ϕ be therein considered as variable, we have the differential equation

$$\sqrt{Q} dp + \sqrt{P} dq + \sqrt{\Phi} d\phi = 0,$$

where P, Q have the foregoing values

$$P = -8\alpha^2\beta^2(\phi^2 - \gamma^2)(a + b - c - \phi)(a + p)(b + p)(c + p), \quad Q = \&c.;$$

and where, if the integral equation be written in the form

$$L + 2M\phi + N\phi^2 = 0,$$

then we have $\Phi = M^2 - NL$, viz. we thus find

$$\Phi = 16\alpha^2\beta^2(a + p)(b + p)(c + p)(a + q)(b + q)(c + q).$$

22. Changing the notation, and writing

$$P = (a + p)(b + p)(c + p), \quad Q = (a + q)(b + q)(c + q), \quad \Phi = (\phi^2 - \gamma^2)(a + b - 2c - \phi),$$

the equation is

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} + \frac{\sqrt{2} d\phi}{\sqrt{\Phi}} = 0;$$

or if, instead of ϕ , we introduce the original parameter σ , then, observing that

$$\frac{2 d\sigma}{\sigma} = \frac{d\phi}{\sqrt{\phi^2 - \gamma^2}},$$

we at once find

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} + \frac{4 d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} = 0,$$

where

$$\Sigma = \gamma(1 + \sigma^4) - 2(a + b - 2c)\sigma^2,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\Sigma = a(\sigma^2 - 1)^2 - b(\sigma^2 + 1)^2 + c \cdot 4\sigma^2;$$

viz. passing from a point (p, q) on the line σ to a consecutive point $(p + dp, q + dq)$ on the line $\sigma + d\sigma$, the above is the relation between the variations $dp, dq, d\sigma$. If τ be the parameter of the other line through the same point, then we have in like manner, say

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} - \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} + \frac{4 d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} = 0,$$

(viz. one of the radicals $\sqrt{P}, \sqrt{Q}$ must present itself with a reversed sign): and we thus have dp, dq each expressed in terms of $d\sigma, d\tau$; viz. we have the increments dp, dq when a point passes from (σ, τ) to $(\sigma + d\sigma, \tau + d\tau)$. These results will be presently obtained in a more simple manner.

Formulae where the position of a Point on the Surface is determined by means of the two Lines through the Point

23. We may determine the position of a point by means of the parameters σ, τ of the two lines through the point. The equations of these are

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} + \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} &= \sigma \left(1 + \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}}\right), & \frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} + \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} &= \tau \left(1 - \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}}\right), \\ \frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} - \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} &= \frac{1}{\sigma} \left(1 - \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}}\right), & \frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} - \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} &= \frac{1}{\tau} \left(1 + \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}}\right), \end{aligned}$$

and from these equations we deduce

$$\frac{x}{\sqrt{a}} = \frac{\sigma\tau + 1}{\tau + \sigma}, \quad \frac{iy}{\sqrt{b}} = \frac{\sigma\tau - 1}{\tau + \sigma}, \quad \frac{z}{\sqrt{c}} = \frac{\tau - \sigma}{\tau + \sigma}.$$

We have thence

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dx}{\sqrt{a}} &= (\tau^2 - 1)d\sigma + (\sigma^2 - 1)d\tau \quad (\div), \\ \frac{idy}{\sqrt{b}} &= (\tau^2 + 1)d\sigma + (\sigma^2 + 1)d\tau \quad (\div), \\ \frac{dz}{\sqrt{c}} &= -2\tau d\sigma + 2\sigma d\tau \quad (\div), \end{aligned}$$

where denom. $= (\tau + \sigma)^2$; regarding σ, τ as the parameters in place of p, q , these show the values of the first differential coefficients $\alpha, \alpha'; \beta, \beta'; \gamma, \gamma'$. We deduce

$$A = -2i\sqrt{bc}(\sigma\tau + 1) \quad (\div), \quad B = -2i\sqrt{ca}(\sigma\tau - 1) \quad (\div), \quad C = -2i\sqrt{ba}(\tau - \sigma) \quad (\div),$$

where denom. $= (\tau + \sigma)^3$. We have, moreover,

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{d^2x}{\sqrt{a}} &= -2(\tau^2 - 1)d\sigma^2 + 2(\sigma\tau + 1)2d\sigma d\tau - 2(\sigma^2 - 1)d\tau^2 \quad (\div), \\ \frac{2d^2y}{\sqrt{b}} &= -2(\tau^2 + 1)d\sigma^2 + 2(\sigma\tau - 1)2d\sigma d\tau - 2(\sigma^2 + 1)d\tau^2 \quad (\div), \\ \frac{d^2z}{\sqrt{c}} &= 4\tau d\sigma^2 + 2(\tau - \sigma)2d\sigma d\tau + 4\sigma d\tau^2 \quad (\div), \end{aligned}$$

where denom. $= (\tau + \sigma)^3$: giving $\alpha, \alpha', \alpha''; \beta, \beta', \beta''; \gamma, \gamma', \gamma''$. We deduce as the numerators of $E' (= A\alpha + B\beta + C\gamma)$ and $G' (= A\alpha'' + B\beta'' + C\gamma'')$,

$$4i\sqrt{abc}\{(\sigma\tau + 1)(\tau^2 - 1) - (\sigma\tau - 1)(\tau^2 + 1) - 2\tau(\tau - \sigma)\} = 0,$$

and

$$4i\sqrt{abc}\{(\sigma\tau + 1)(\sigma^2 - 1) - (\sigma\tau - 1)(\sigma^2 + 1) + 2\sigma(\tau - \sigma)\} = 0;$$

that is, $E' = 0$ and $G' = 0$; or the differential equation of the chief lines is $d\sigma d\tau = 0$, which is right. The value of $F' (= A\alpha' + B\beta' + C\gamma')$ is hardly required, but it is readily found to be

$$= 4i\sqrt{abc}\{-(\sigma\tau + 1)^2 + (\sigma\tau - 1)^2 - (\tau - \sigma)^2\} \div (\tau + \sigma)^6;$$

or since the term in braces is $-(\tau + \sigma)^2$, we have

$$F' = \frac{-4i\sqrt{abc}}{(\tau + \sigma)^4}.$$

24. The values of E, F, G ($ds^2 = E d\sigma^2 + 2F d\sigma d\tau + G d\tau^2$) are

$$\begin{aligned} E &= a(\tau^2 - 1)^2 - b(\tau^2 + 1)^2 + c \cdot 4\tau^2 \quad (\div), \\ F &= a(\tau^2 - 1)(\sigma^2 - 1) - b(\tau^2 + 1)(\sigma^2 + 1) - c \cdot 4\tau\sigma \quad (\div), \\ G &= a(\sigma^2 - 1)^2 - b(\sigma^2 + 1)^2 + c \cdot 4\sigma^2 \quad (\div), \end{aligned}$$

where $\text{denom.} = (\tau + \sigma)^4$.

We have, it is clear, ($E_1 = d_\sigma E$, $E_2 = d_\tau E$, &c.)

$$E_1 = -\frac{4}{\sigma + \tau}E, \quad G_2 = -\frac{4}{\sigma + \tau}G.$$

Hence the condition $FG_2 - 2F_2G + GG_1 = 0$, in order that $\sigma = \text{const.}$ may be a geodesic, reduces itself to

$$-\frac{4}{\sigma + \tau}F - 2F_2 + G_1 = 0;$$

and similarly, the condition $-2EF_1 + E_1F + EE_2 = 0$, in order that $\tau = \text{const.}$ may be a geodesic, reduces itself to

$$-\frac{4}{\sigma + \tau}F - 2F_1 + E_2 = 0.$$

We have at once

$$\begin{aligned} E_2 &= 4a(\tau^2 - 1)(\tau\sigma + 1) - 4b(\tau^2 + 1)(\tau\sigma - 1) + 4c \cdot 2\tau(\sigma - \tau) \quad (\div), \\ G_1 &= 4a(\sigma^2 - 1)(\tau\sigma + 1) - 4b(\sigma^2 + 1)(\tau\sigma - 1) - 4c \cdot 2\sigma(\sigma - \tau) \quad (\div), \\ F_1 &= 2a(\tau^2 - 1)(\tau\sigma - \sigma^2 + 2) - 2b(\tau^2 + 1)(\tau\sigma - \sigma^2 - 2) - 2c \cdot 2\tau(\tau - 3\sigma) \quad (\div), \\ F_2 &= 2a(\sigma^2 - 1)(\tau\sigma - \tau^2 + 2) - 2b(\sigma^2 + 1)(\tau\sigma - \tau^2 - 2) - 2c \cdot 2\sigma(\sigma - 3\tau) \quad (\div), \end{aligned}$$

where $\text{denom.} = (\sigma + \tau)^5$; and substituting these values, the conditions are verified: we thus again see *a posteriori* that the right lines $\sigma = \text{const.}$ and $\tau = \text{const.}$ are geodesics.

25. The last-mentioned values of E, G are $E = T \div (\tau + \sigma)^4$, $G = \Sigma \div (\tau + \sigma)^4$; and writing for a moment

$$A = a(\tau^2 - 1)(\sigma^2 - 1) - b(\tau^2 + 1)(\sigma^2 + 1) - c \cdot 4\sigma\tau,$$

we have $F = A \div (\tau + \sigma)^4$, the value of ds^2 is thus

$$= \frac{T d\sigma^2 + 2A d\sigma d\tau + \Sigma d\tau^2}{(\tau + \sigma)^4},$$

which should be

$$= \frac{1}{4}(p - q) \left(p \frac{dp^2}{P} - q \frac{dq^2}{Q} \right),$$

where, as before,

$$P, Q = (a + p)(b + p)(c + p), \quad (a + q)(b + q)(c + q),$$

respectively. We have already found

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} + \frac{4 d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} = 0, \quad \frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} - \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} + \frac{4 d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} = -2 \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} + \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right), \quad \frac{dq}{\sqrt{Q}} = -2 \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} - \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right);$$

and we ought therefore to have identically

$$(p - q) \left\{ p \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} + \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right)^2 - q \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} - \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right)^2 \right\} = \frac{T d\sigma^2 + 2A d\sigma d\tau + \Sigma d\tau^2}{(\tau + \sigma)^4};$$

that is

$$(p - q)^2 = \frac{T\Sigma}{(\tau + \sigma)^4}, \quad p^2 - q^2 = \frac{A\sqrt{T\Sigma}}{(\tau + \sigma)^4},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(p - q)^2 = \frac{T\Sigma}{(\tau + \sigma)^4}, \quad p + q = \frac{A}{(\tau + \sigma)^2},$$

which are easily verified.

26. In fact, the equation

$$\frac{x^2}{a + u} + \frac{y^2}{b + u} + \frac{z^2}{c + u} = 1$$

gives for u a quadric equation, the roots of which are $u = p, u = q$; that is, we have

$$\begin{aligned} p + q &= x^2 + y^2 + z^2 - a - b - c, \\ pq &= -(b + c)x^2 - (c + a)y^2 - (a + b)z^2 + bc + ca + ab; \end{aligned}$$

and substituting herein for x^2, y^2, z^2 their values in terms of σ, τ , we find

$$\begin{aligned} p + q &= \frac{a(\sigma^2 - 1)(\tau^2 - 1) - b(\sigma^2 + 1)(\tau^2 + 1) - 4c\sigma\tau}{(\tau + \sigma)^2}, \\ pq &= \frac{bc(\sigma\tau + 1)^2 - ca(\sigma\tau - 1)^2 + ab(\sigma - \tau)^2}{(\tau + \sigma)^4}, \end{aligned}$$

the first of which is, in fact, $p + q = A \div (\tau + \sigma)^2$. And from the two equations, forming the combination $(p + q)^2 - 4pq$, we at once obtain the other equation

$$(p - q)^2 = \frac{\Sigma T}{(\tau + \sigma)^4}.$$

27. The most ready way of obtaining the relations between the differentials of p, q, σ, τ , is from the foregoing expressions of $p + q, pq$. Writing for a moment $p + q = A \div (\sigma + \tau)^2$, $pq = B \div (\sigma + \tau)^2$, we have $p^2(\sigma + \tau)^2 - Ap + B = 0$, $q^2(\sigma + \tau)^2 - Aq + B = 0$; viz. the first of these equations is

$$\begin{aligned} p^2(\sigma + \tau)^2 - p\{a(\sigma^2 - 1)(\tau^2 - 1) - b(\sigma^2 + 1)(\tau^2 + 1) - 4c\sigma\tau\} \\ + bc(\sigma\tau + 1)^2 - ca(\sigma\tau - 1)^2 + ab(\sigma - \tau)^2 = 0, \end{aligned}$$

which is quadric in p, σ, τ . The negative discriminants in regard to these variables respectively are $\Sigma T, 4PT, 4P\Sigma$ respectively, and we have thus the equation

$$\frac{dp}{\sqrt{P}} + 2\left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} + \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}}\right) = 0;$$

and the like equation for dq .

28. In the first integral of the geodesic lines, introducing σ, τ instead of p, q , the equation becomes

$$\sqrt{\frac{p}{p + \theta}} \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} + \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right) - \sqrt{\frac{q}{q + \theta}} \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} - \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right) = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$p(q + \theta) \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} + \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right)^2 - q(p + \theta) \left(\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} - \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}} \right)^2 = 0;$$

that is,

$$(p - q)\theta \left(\frac{d\sigma^2}{\Sigma} + \frac{d\tau^2}{T} \right) + 2\{2pq + \theta(p + q)\} \frac{d\sigma d\tau}{\sqrt{\Sigma T}} = 0;$$

or substituting herein for $p - q, pq, p + q$ the values $\sqrt{\Sigma T}, B, A$, each divided by $(\sigma + \tau)^2$, this is

$$\theta(T d\sigma^2 + \Sigma d\tau^2) + 2(2B + \theta A)d\sigma d\tau = 0,$$

or say

$$\theta(T d\sigma^2 + 2A d\sigma d\tau + \Sigma d\tau^2) + 4B d\sigma d\tau = 0;$$

viz. writing herein $\theta = 0$, the equation is $d\sigma d\tau = 0$, giving the right lines on the surface; and writing $\theta = \infty$, it is $T d\sigma^2 + 2A d\sigma d\tau + \Sigma d\tau^2 = 0$, giving the circular lines.

29. The equation

$$ds^2 = \frac{T d\sigma^2 + 2A d\sigma d\tau + \Sigma d\tau^2}{(\tau + \sigma)^4}$$

shows that the right lines $\sigma, \sigma + d\sigma, \tau, \tau + d\tau$ on the surface are indefinitely small parallelograms, the sides whereof are $\sqrt{T} d\sigma \div (\tau + \sigma)^2$ and $\sqrt{\Sigma} d\tau \div (\tau + \sigma)^2$, viz. the ratio of the coefficients of $d\sigma, d\tau$ is of the form function $\sigma \div$ function τ ; and it thus appears that it is possible to draw on the surface the two sets of right lines, the lines of each set being at such intervals that the surface is divided into parallelograms, the sides of which have to each other any given ratio (the angles being variable); viz. if this ratio be as $m : 1$, then, to determine the relation between σ, τ , we must have $\sqrt{T} d\sigma = \pm m \sqrt{\Sigma} d\tau$, or what is the same thing,

$$\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} = \pm m \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}}.$$

In particular, if $m = 1$, the parallelograms will be rhombs; and we must then have

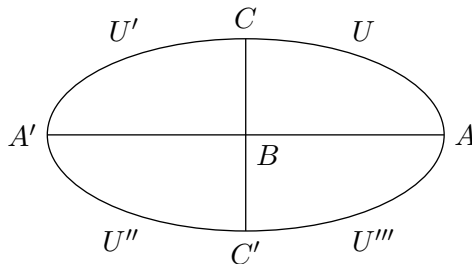
$$\frac{d\sigma}{\sqrt{\Sigma}} = \pm \frac{d\tau}{\sqrt{T}};$$

viz. this being in terms of σ, τ , the differential equation of the curves of curvature, it appears that the two sets of lines may be taken so as to divide the surface into indefinitely small rhombs, such that, drawing the diagonals of these, we have the two sets of curves of curvature.

The Ellipsoid and the Skew Hyperboloid

30. I have thus far considered a quadric surface in general, the various theorems being applicable as well to the ellipsoid and the hyperboloid of two sheets as to the skew hyperboloid, the right lines being of course imaginary for the first-mentioned surfaces; but I will now consider the ellipsoid and the skew hyperboloid separately.

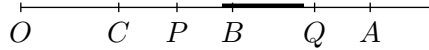
31. First the ellipsoid. We have here a, b, c all positive, and I assume as usual $a > b > c$. The principal sections are all ellipses, viz. $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$ is the major-mean, or say the minor section, $\frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$ the minor-mean, or say the major section, and $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$ the mean, or umbilicar section. The elliptic coordinates p, q enter into the equations symmetrically, but we distinguish them by taking p to extend from $-c$ to $-b$, and q to extend from $-b$ to $-a$. Thus $p = \text{const.}$ denotes the curves of curvature of the one kind; viz. $p = -c$ denotes the major-mean section $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, $p = -b$ the portions UU' and $U''U'''$ of the umbilicar section; and $q = \text{const.}$ denotes the curves of curvature of the other kind, viz. $q = -b$ the remaining portions $U'U''$ and $U'''U$ of the umbilicar section, $q = -a$ the minor-mean section $\frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$; say $p = \text{const.}$ the major-mean curves, and $q = \text{const.}$ the minor-mean curves.



32. Hence, in order that the equation

$$dp\sqrt{\frac{p}{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)(\theta+p)}} \pm dq\sqrt{\frac{q}{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)(\theta+q)}} = 0$$

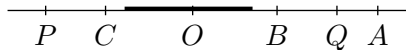
of the geodesic lines may be real (observing that we have $a+p, b+p = +, c+p, p = -,$ and $a+q = +, b+q, c+q, q = -,$ consequently $p \div (a+p)(b+p)(c+p) = +,$ but $q \div (a+q)(b+q)(c+q) = -$), we must have $\theta+p, \theta+q$ of opposite signs, that is $\theta+p = +$ and $\theta+q = -$; or θ included between the limits a, c . Or, what is the same thing, $-\theta$ is included between the limits $-c, -b$, say $-\theta$ has a p -value; or else between the limits $-b, -a$, say $-\theta$ has a q -value. This is conveniently shown in the annexed diagram of the values of $-p, -q, -\theta$.



Hence on the ellipsoid we have two kinds of geodesic lines, each of them touching a real curve of curvature; viz. those which touch a major-mean curve and those which touch a minor-mean curve: the transition case, answering to the value $\theta = b$, is that of the geodesic lines which pass through an umbilicus. I have considered the theory more in detail in my memoir “On the Geodesic Lines of an Ellipsoid,” *Mem. R. Ast. Soc.*, t. xxx., pp. 31–53, 1872, [478].

33. Next, for the skew hyperboloid, we have a and $b = +, c = -,$ and I assume for convenience $a > b$. Attending to the signs, we still have therefore $a > b > c$. The principal sections are one of them an ellipse, and the other two hyperbolas, viz. the minor section is the ellipse $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, the major section is the hyperbola $\frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$, and the mean section is the hyperbola $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$: there are no umbilici. The elliptic coordinates enter symmetrically; but, as before, we distinguish them, viz. we take p to extend from $-c$ (a positive value) to infinity, and q from $-b$ to $-a$. Thus $p = \text{const.}$ denotes the curves of curvature of the one kind, viz. $p = -c$ the ellipse $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, and every other value of p an oval curve surrounding the hyperboloid; and $q = \text{const.}$ the curves of curvature of the other kind, viz. $q = -c$ the major hyperbola $\frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$, $q = -b$ the mean hyperbola $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$, and each intermediate value gives a curve of curvature of a hyperbolic form: we may say that $p = \text{const.}$ determines the oval curves of curvature, and $q = \text{const.}$ the hyperbolic curves of curvature.

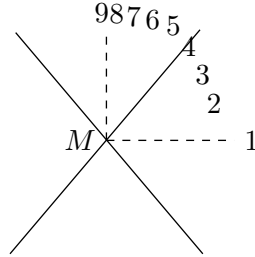
34. In the equation of the geodesic lines we have $a+p, b+p, c+p, p$ all positive; but $a+q = +, b+q, c+q, q$ each $= -$; thence $p \div (a+p)(b+p)(c+p) = +,$ but $q \div (a+q)(b+q)(c+q) = -$; therefore $\theta+p$ and $\theta+q$ must be of opposite signs, or we must have $\theta+p = +$ and $\theta+q = -$; or what is the same thing, θ may have any value from $-p$ to $-q$, or say $-\theta$ any value from p to q ; that is, the value of $-\theta$ may be positive and greater than $-c$, positive and less than $-c$, negative and less than $-b$, negative and between $-b$ and $-a$; viz. in the first case $-\theta$ has a p -value, and in the fourth case it has a q -value, but in the second and third cases it has neither a p - nor a q -value. This is better seen from the diagram.



It follows that we have, on the hyperboloid, geodesic lines of four different kinds: those which touch a real curve of curvature, oval or hyperbolic, and those which touch no real curve of curvature, but for which $-\theta$ has a positive value from 0 to $-c$, or a negative value from 0 to $-b$. And there are the transitional cases $-\theta = -c$, where the geodesic touches the ellipse $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$; $\theta = 0$, where the geodesic becomes a right line; and $-\theta = -b$, where the geodesic touches the mean hyperbola $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1$.

35. To explain this more in detail, consider the geodesics which start from a point M of the hyperboloid. To fix the ideas, consider the axis of z as vertical, and take the point M in the positive octant of the hyperboloid; and let $M1$ represent the direction of the oval curve of curvature, $M9$ that of the hyperbolic curve of curvature, $M5$ that of one of the right lines.

The geodesic of initial direction $M1$ touches at M the oval curve of curvature $M1$, and lies wholly above this curve; it makes an infinity of convolutions round the upper part of the hyperboloid, cutting all the oval curves of curvature for which p has a positive value greater than p_1 (if p_1 is the value of p corresponding to the oval curve through M), and ascending to infinity: or considering the curve as described in the opposite sense, it descends from infinity to touch the oval curve through M , after which it again ascends to infinity.



Next, if the initial direction is $M2$, we have a geodesic of the same kind, only descending below M to touch a certain oval curve having for its parameter p_2 ($p_2 > -c < p_1$).

We come next to a critical direction $M3$, for which the geodesic descends below M to touch the oval curve of parameter $p_3 = -c$, that is, the ellipse $\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} = 1$. But it is to be observed that, whatever the initial point M may be, the geodesic makes below M an infinity of convolutions round the hyperboloid, so that it does not in fact ever actually touch the ellipse, but has this ellipse for an asymptote. That this is so appears from the consideration that the ellipse, *qua* plane curve of curvature, is a geodesic; so that, starting from a point of the ellipse in the direction of the ellipse, the geodesic coincides with the ellipse, or, besides the ellipse itself, there is not any geodesic which touches the ellipse.

Next, if the initial direction be $M4$, the geodesic does not here touch any oval curve; it descends through M below the ellipse $\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} = 1$, lying in the upper and lower portions of the hyperboloid, and making round it an infinity of convolutions.

36. We come, then, to the initial direction $M5$, which is that of the right line; the geodesic here coincides with the right line.

In the cases which follow, the geodesic lies in the upper and lower portions of the hyperboloid, cutting all the oval curves of curvature.

Initial direction $M6$: the geodesic does not touch any hyperbolic curve of curvature, but makes round the hyperboloid an infinity of convolutions.

Initial direction $M7$: the geodesic touches at opposite infinities the mean hyperbola $\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{z^2}{c} = 1$, it lies wholly in front of the plane $y = 0$ of this hyperbola.

Initial direction $M8$: the geodesic touches a hyperbolic curve of curvature parameter q_8 where q_8 (negative) is between $-b$ and q_9 the parameter of the hyperbolic curve of curvature through M ; viz. it cuts all the hyperbolic curves the parameters of which are between $-b$ and q_8 , but does not cut the remaining curves the parameters of which extend from q_8 to $-a$.

Lastly, initial direction is $M9$, that of the hyperbolic curve of curvature through M ; the geodesic touches this curve, cutting all the hyperbolic curves the parameters of which are between $-b$ and q_9 , but not any of those the parameters of which are between q_9 and $-a$.

37. If in the differential equation of the geodesic line we consider p, q as the elliptic coordinates of a given point M of the curve, the equation for a given value of θ determines the direction of the curve; or conversely, if the direction be given, the equation determines the value of the parameter θ . Writing

$$\frac{dp\sqrt{p}}{\sqrt{(a+p)(b+p)(c+p)}} = P, \quad \frac{dq\sqrt{q}}{\sqrt{(a+q)(b+q)(c+q)}} = Q,$$

then P, Q are proportional to the rectangular coordinates of a consecutive point M' , measured from M in the directions of the hyperbolic and oval curves of curvature respectively; and the differential

equation of the geodesic lines gives

$$\frac{P}{\sqrt{p+\theta}} \pm \frac{Q}{\sqrt{q+\theta}} = 0;$$

viz. if ϕ be the inclination of the geodesic to the hyperbolic curve of curvature, then $Q = P \tan \phi$, or we have

$$\frac{1}{p+\theta} = \frac{\tan^2 \phi}{q+\theta},$$

that is, $p \tan^2 \phi - q = \theta(1 - \tan^2 \phi)$; hence, if for the right line $\phi = \lambda$, then $p \tan^2 \lambda - q = 0$; and therefore

$$\theta = \frac{p(\tan^2 \phi - \tan^2 \lambda)}{1 - \tan^2 \phi},$$

viz. $\phi = 0$, $\theta = -q$, $\theta = \infty$, $\theta = -p$, as it should be.

[509]

509. PLAN OF A CURVE-TRACING APPARATUS

[From the *Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society*, vol. iv. (1871–1873), pp. 345–347. Read May 8, 1873.]

I have devised a curve-tracing apparatus on the following plan:

Imagine two planes Π, Π' moving in the same horizontal plane, and above the two planes respectively the two points P, P' moving in the same or a parallel plane.

To fix the ideas, suppose that the two planes each move according to a law (that is, let the motion of each of them depend on a single variable parameter; for instance, they may each of them rotate about an axis); but let the motion of the two points be free.

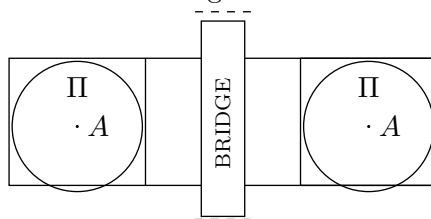
Suppose, next, that the planes are connected together in such manner that the motion of one of them determines the motion of the other (e.g. by a train of wheel-work); and that the two points are also connected together in such manner that the motion of one of them determines the motion of the other (e.g. by a pentagraph, or by a slotted rod, the slot of which works on an axle, so as to allow the rod to move lengthways as well as rotate).

Suppose, finally, that one of the points, say P' , is attached to a point of the plane Π' ; then the plane Π being set in motion, this determines the motion of Π' , consequently of P' , consequently of P ; and the moving point P , or say the pencil P , will describe on the moving plane Π a curve, the nature of which will of course depend on the nature of the motions of Π, Π' , and on that of the connection between these planes and of the connections between the points P and P' .

I propose to describe the apparatus as nearly as I have actually constructed it. (See sketch-plan Fig. 1, and side-elevation Fig. 2.)

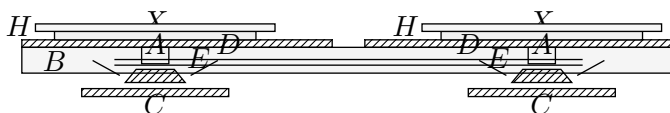
The framework of the instrument consists of two longitudinal bars (B) each about three feet long, one inch thick, and three inches broad, supported edgewise at a distance of about eighteen inches on the cross-pieces C, C ; and half-way between them, supported by the same cross-pieces, is an axis carrying at each extremity two mitre wheels. The bars B support three cross-pieces D, D, D , and between these are the moveable cross-pieces E, E carrying the axes A, A with the attached mitre wheels, and circular disks X, X . Each of these wheels separately may be placed (as in the figure) out of gear with the two vertical wheels, or it can (by moving the cross-piece E) be brought into gear with either of these wheels. Each axis A passes through a circular disk H , capable of rotating about it, so that it may be fixed in any position, and serving as the bearing for the plane X .

Fig. 1.



The disks X, X may be regarded as being themselves the planes Π, Π (say these planes are rigidly attached to X, X respectively); or we may, in any other manner, move the plane Π by means of the disk X ; for instance, X may carry a spur-wheel gearing into a spur-wheel on the under surface of Π , and thereby communicating a rotation of different velocity to the plane Π ; or the connection may be as in the ordinary oval chuck. In any such case, the disk H (which, for this reason, was made to project beyond X) serves as a support for the plane Π , and the apparatus connected therewith; and observe that the angular position of such apparatus, and therefore of the path of any point of Π , may be varied at pleasure by moving the disk H through any angle.

Fig. 2.



Detached altogether from the rest of the instrument, or what is better, supported on longitudinal pieces carried by the cross-pieces C, C we have a bridge (see fig. 1) capable of adjustment as regards height, and serving as a support for the pentagraph-apparatus, or other connection of the one plane Π with the pencil which works upon the other plane Π .

It is hardly necessary to remark that in the simple form of the instrument where the disks X, X are themselves the planes Π, Π , then putting the mitre wheel of one plane X in gear with either of the corresponding vertical wheels, and making the plane rotate, the other plane X will rotate with the same angular velocity, in the same or the opposite direction, or it will remain at rest, according as its mitre wheel is in gear with one or the other of the corresponding vertical wheels, or is out of gear with each of them.

[510]

510. ON BICURSAL CURVES

[From the *Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society*, vol. iv. (1871–1873), pp. 347–352. Read May 8, 1873.]

A curve of deficiency 1 may be termed bicursal; there is some distinction according as the order is even or odd, and to fix the ideas I take it to be even.

A bicursal curve of the order n contains

$$\frac{1}{2}n(n+3) - \left\{ \frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2) - 1 \right\} = 3n$$

constants; hence, if the order is $= 2n$, the number of constants is $= 6n$; such a curve is normally represented by a system of equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^n + (1, \theta)^{n-2} \sqrt{\Theta},$$

where Θ is a quartic function, which may be taken to be of the form $(1 - \theta^2)(1 - k^2\theta^2)$, or otherwise to depend on a single constant; viz. (x, y, z) are proportional to n -thic functions involving such a

radical: since in the values of (x, y, z) one constant divides out, the number of constants is $3\{(n+1) + (n-1)\} - 1 + 1 = 6n$, as it should be.

But the curve of the order $2n$ may be abnormally or improperly represented by a system of equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^{n+k} + (1, \theta)^{n+k-2}\sqrt{\Theta},$$

viz. these equations, instead of representing a curve of the order $2n + 2k$, will represent a curve of the order $2n$, provided only there exist $2k$ common values of θ for which each of the three functions vanish. The passage to a normal representation is effected by finding θ' a function of $\theta, \sqrt{\Theta}$ (viz. an irrational function of θ) such that the foregoing equations become

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta')^n + (1, \theta')^{n-2}\sqrt{\Theta'};$$

it is shown that such a transformation is possible, and a mode of effecting it, derived from a theorem of Hermite's in relation to the Jacobian H, Θ functions, is given in Clebsch's Memoir "Ueber diejenigen Curven, deren Coordinaten sich als elliptische Functionen eines Parameters darstellen lassen," *Crelle*, t. LXIV. (1865), pp. 210–270. The demonstration is a very interesting one, and I reproduce it at the end of this paper. I remark, in passing, that the analogous reduction in the case of unicursal curves is self-evident; the equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^{n+k}$$

will represent a curve, not of the order $n + k$, but of the order n , provided there exist k common values of θ for which the three functions vanish; in fact, the three functions have then a common factor of the order k , and omitting this, the form is $(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^n$.

Returning to the curves of deficiency 1, we see that a curve of the order $2m + 2n$ contains $6(m + n)$ constants, and is normally represented by a system of equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^{m+n} + (1, \theta)^{m+n-2}\sqrt{\Theta}.$$

Such a curve may be otherwise represented: we may derive it by a rational transformation from the curve ($D = 1$) of the order 4 (binodal quartic), the equation of which is

$$(1, u)^2(1, v)^2 = 0;$$

viz. the coordinates are here connected by a quadriquadric equation; and we then express x, y, z in terms of these by a system of equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, u)^m(1, v)^n.$$

It is, however, to be observed that the form of these functions is not determinate: each of them may be altered by adding to it a term $(1, u)^{m-2}(1, v)^{n-2}\{(1, u)^2(1, v)^2\}$, where the second factor is that belonging to the quadriquadric transformation, and the first factor is arbitrary. Using the arbitrary function to simplify the form, the real number of constants is reduced to $(m+1)(n+1) - (m-1)(n-1) = 2(m+n)$; or the three functions contain together $6(m+n)$ constants, one of which divides out. The quadriquadric equation, dividing out one constant, contains eight constants; but reducing by linear transformations on u, v respectively, the number of constants is $8 - 6 = 2$. Hence, in the system of equations, the whole number of constants is $6(m+n) - 1 + 2 = 6(m+n) + 1$; viz. this is greater by unity than the number of constants in the curve ($D = 1$) of the order $2(m+n)$. The explanation of the excess is that the same curve of the order $2(m+n)$ may be derived from the different quartic curves $(1, u)^2(1, v)^2 = 0$; this will be further examined.

The transition from the one form to the other is not immediately obvious; in fact, if from the quadriquadric equation $(1, u)^2(1, v)^2 = 0$ (say this is $A + 2Bv + Cv^2 = 0$, where A, B, C are quadric functions of u) we determine v ; this gives $Cv = -B + \sqrt{B^2 - AC}$, $= -B + \sqrt{\Omega}$ suppose; and then substituting in the equations $(x, y, z) = (1, u)^m(1, v)^n$, we find

$$(x, y, z) = (1, u)^m(C, -B + \sqrt{\Omega})^n;$$

viz. we have (x, y, z) proportional to functions of u , involving the quartic radical $\sqrt{\Omega}$; but these functions are of the order (not $m + n$, but) $m + 2n$.

In particular, if $n = m$, then, instead of functions of the order $2n$, we have functions of the order $3n$. The reduction in this last case to the form where the order is $2n$ can be effected without difficulty, but in the general case where m and n are unequal, I do not know how it is to be effected except by the general process explained in Clebsch's Memoir.

We may, in fact, by linear transformations on u, v , reduce the quadriquadric relation to

$$\begin{array}{r} 1 \\ +u^2 \\ +2buv \\ +v^2 \end{array} + cu^2v^2 = 0,$$

that is

$$1 + u^2 + 2buv + v^2 + cu^2v^2 = 0;$$

or putting herein $u + v = p$, $uv = q$, the relation is

$$1 + p^2 - 2q + 2bq + cq^2 = 0,$$

that is

$$p^2 = -1 + (2 - 2b)q - cq^2, \quad p^2 - 4q = -1 + (-2 - 2b)q - cq^2;$$

viz. extracting the square roots,

$$u + v = \sqrt{Q}, \quad u - v = \sqrt{Q'},$$

if for shortness

$$Q = -1 + (2 - 2b)q - cq^2, \quad Q' = -1 + (-2 - 2b)q - cq^2;$$

we may then rationalise one of the radicals, for instance Q ; viz. writing

$$-c\{-1 + (2 - 2b)q - cq^2\} = \{cq - (1 - b)\}^2 + c - (1 - b)^2,$$

then, if

$$cq - (1 - b) = \sqrt{c - (1 - b)^2} \cdot \frac{1}{2} \left(\theta - \frac{1}{\theta} \right),$$

this becomes

$$-cQ = \{c - (1 - b)^2\} \left\{ \frac{1}{4} \left(\theta - \frac{1}{\theta} \right)^2 + 1 \right\} = \{c - (1 - b)^2\} \cdot \frac{1}{4} \left(\theta + \frac{1}{\theta} \right)^2,$$

that is

$$\sqrt{Q} = \frac{1}{2} \sqrt{\frac{c - (1 - b)^2}{-c}} \left(\theta + \frac{1}{\theta} \right);$$

and the corresponding value of $\sqrt{Q'}$ is

$$\sqrt{Q'} = \sqrt{\frac{1}{4} \frac{c - (1 - b)^2}{-c} \left(\theta + \frac{1}{\theta} \right)^2 - 4q},$$

where q stands for its value

$$\frac{1}{c} \left\{ 1 - b + \sqrt{c - (1 - b)^2} \cdot \frac{1}{2} \left(\theta - \frac{1}{\theta} \right) \right\}.$$

We may write these in the form

$$1 : \frac{1}{2} \sqrt{Q} : \frac{1}{2} \sqrt{Q'} = M\theta : 1 + \theta^2 : \sqrt{\Theta},$$

where M is a constant, and Θ is a quartic function of θ , such that $(1 + \theta^2)^2 - \Theta$ is a quadric function only of θ .

The equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, u)^m (1, v)^n$$

thus assume the form

$$(x, y, z) = (M\theta, 1 + \theta^2 + \sqrt{\Theta})^m (M\theta, 1 + \theta^2 - \sqrt{\Theta})^n;$$

and on the right-hand side the term of the highest order in θ is

$$(1 + \theta^2 + \sqrt{\Theta})^m (1 + \theta^2 - \sqrt{\Theta})^n,$$

viz. if $n =$ or $> m$, then this is

$$\{(1 + \theta^2)^2 - \Theta\}^m (1 + \theta^2 - \sqrt{\Theta})^{n-m}.$$

This is

$$= (1, \theta)^{2m} (1 + \theta^2 - \sqrt{\Theta})^{n-m},$$

which is of the order $2m + 2(n - m) = 2n$ (which, in virtue of $n =$ or $> m$, is $=$ or $> m + n$). In particular, if $n = m$, then the highest order is $= 2n$; or the curve of the order $2n$, as represented by the equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, u)^n (1, v)^n,$$

where (u, v) are connected by a quadriquadric equation, is also represented by the equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^n + (1, \theta)^{n-2} \sqrt{\Theta},$$

which is the required transformation of the original equations.

It is to be noticed that the foregoing form,

$$\begin{array}{r} 1 \qquad + u^2 \\ \qquad + 2buv \\ + v^2 \quad + cu^2 v^2 = 0, \end{array}$$

is the most special form to which the quadriquadric relation can be reduced by the linear transformations of u, v ; in fact, by mere division, the equation is made to have the constant term 1; the number of the coefficients of transformation is then $3 + 3 = 6$; and to reduce the relation to the foregoing form, we have the six conditions, coeff. $u = 0$, coeff. $v = 0$, coeff. $uv^2 = 0$, coeff. $v^2u = 0$, coeff. $u^2 = 1$, coeff. $v^2 = 1$; but in this form, expressing v in terms of u , the radical is $\sqrt{\Omega}$, where

$$\Omega = (1 + u^2)(1 + cu^2) - b^2u^2,$$

which is not more general than if we had

$$\Omega = (1 + u^2)(1 + cu^2),$$

viz. there is a superfluous constant b . And we thus see how it is that the system of equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, u)^n (1, v)^n,$$

(u, v) connected by a quadriquadric relation, contains, not $6n$, but $6n + 1$ constants, one of these being superfluous.

Clebsch's transformation, above referred to, is as follows:

Starting with the equations

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta)^{n+k} + (1, \theta)^{n+k-2} \sqrt{\Theta},$$

if the function Θ is not originally of the standard form, we may, by a linear substitution, reduce it to this form, viz. we may write

$$\Theta = \theta(1 - \theta)(1 - k^2\theta);$$

and then writing $\theta = \text{sn}^2 u$, ($\text{sn}^2 \text{am } u$), we have

$$\sqrt{\Theta} = \text{sn } u \text{ cn } u \text{ dn } u = \text{sn } u \text{ sn}' u;$$

so that the formulae become

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \text{sn}^2 u)^{n+k} + (1, \text{sn}^2 u)^{n+k-2} \text{sn } u \text{ sn}' u.$$

Hermite's theorem, used in the demonstration, is that any such function of $\text{sn } u$ is expressible in the form

$$C \frac{H(u - \alpha_1)H(u - \alpha_2) \cdots H(u - \alpha_{2n+2k})}{\Theta^{2n+2k}(u)}$$

(H, Θ denoting here the two Jacobian functions), where

$$\alpha_1 + \alpha_2 \cdots + \alpha_{2n+2k} = 0.$$

Observe, in passing, that the equation

$$0 = (1, \text{sn}^2 u)^{n+k} + (1, \text{sn}^2 u)^{n+k-2} \text{sn } u \text{ sn}' u$$

gives, when rationalised, an equation in $\text{sn}^2 u$ of the order $2n + 2k$; its roots are

$$\text{sn}^2 \alpha_1, \text{sn}^2 \alpha_2, \dots, \text{sn}^2 \alpha_{2n+2k}.$$

Considering the functions $(1, \text{sn}^2 u)^{n+k}$ and $(1, \text{sn}^2 u)^{n+k-2}$ as indeterminate, the coefficients can be found so that all but one of the roots of the equation in $\text{sn}^2 u$ shall have any given values whatever,

$$\text{sn}^2 \alpha_1, \text{sn}^2 \alpha_2, \dots, \text{sn}^2 \alpha_{2n+2k-1};$$

the theorem then shows that the remaining root is $\text{sn}^2 \alpha_{2n+2k}$, where

$$-\alpha_{2n+2k} = \alpha_1 + \alpha_2 \cdots + \alpha_{2n+2k-1},$$

which is, in fact, Abel's theorem.

Now, supposing that the three functions of θ all vanish for $2k$ common values of θ , each of the functions of u will contain the same $2k$ H functions, say these are $H(u - \alpha_{2n+1}) \cdots H(u - \alpha_{2n+2k})$. Omitting these and also the denominator factor $\Theta^{2k}(u)$, we have the set of equations

$$(x, y, z) = C \frac{H(u - \alpha_1)H(u - \alpha_2) \cdots H(u - \alpha_{2n})}{\Theta^{2n}(u)},$$

where, however,

$$\alpha_1 + \alpha_2 \cdots + \alpha_{2n} \neq 0,$$

the values $\alpha_1, \alpha_2, \dots, \alpha_{2n}$ are of course different for the three coordinates x, y, z respectively; viz. we have

$$\alpha_1 + \alpha_2 \cdots + \alpha_{2n} = -(\alpha_{2n+1} + \cdots + \alpha_{2n+2k}) = 2ns \quad \text{suppose.}$$

Writing then

$$u = u' + s, \quad \alpha_1 = \alpha'_1 + s, \quad \alpha_2 = \alpha'_2 + s, \dots, \quad \alpha_{2n} = \alpha'_{2n} + s,$$

and consequently

$$\alpha'_1 + \alpha'_2 + \cdots + \alpha'_{2n} = 0,$$

we have

$$(x, y, z) = C \frac{H(u' - \alpha'_1) \cdots H(u' - \alpha'_{2n})}{\Theta^{2n}(u' + s)};$$

or, changing the common denominator,

$$(x, y, z) = C \frac{H(u' - \alpha'_1) \cdots H(u' - \alpha'_{2n})}{\Theta^{2n}(u')},$$

where

$$\alpha'_1 + \alpha'_2 \cdots + \alpha'_{2n} = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \operatorname{sn}^2 u')^n + (1, \operatorname{sn}^2 u')^{n-2} \operatorname{sn} u' \operatorname{sn}' u';$$

viz. writing $\operatorname{sn} u' = \theta'$, and $\Theta' = \theta'(1 - \theta')(1 - k^2 \theta')$, this is

$$(x, y, z) = (1, \theta')^n + (1, \theta')^{n-2} \sqrt{\Theta'},$$

a normal representation of the curve of the order $2n$.

The relation between the parameters θ, θ' is given by $\theta' = \operatorname{sn}^2(u - s)$, $\operatorname{sn}^2 u = \theta$, that is, we have

$$\sqrt{\theta'} = \frac{\sqrt{\theta} \operatorname{cn} s \operatorname{dn} s - \operatorname{sn} s \sqrt{(1 - \theta)(1 - k^2 \theta)}}{1 - k^2 \operatorname{sn}^2 s \theta};$$

or, writing $\operatorname{sn}^2 s = \sigma$, this is

$$\theta' = \frac{\sqrt{\theta} \sqrt{(1 - \sigma)(1 - k^2 \sigma)} - \sqrt{\sigma} \sqrt{(1 - \theta)(1 - k^2 \theta)}}{1 - k^2 \sigma \theta};$$

and, conversely, we have

$$\theta = \frac{\sqrt{\theta'} \sqrt{(1 - \sigma)(1 - k^2 \sigma)} + \sqrt{\sigma} \sqrt{(1 - \theta')(1 - k^2 \theta')}}{1 - k^2 \sigma \theta'}.$$

and the theorem, in fact, shows that, substituting this value of θ in the functions of θ which serve to express x, y, z , these become *proportional* to the functions of θ' ; viz. they become equal to these functions, each multiplied by an irrational function $A' + B'\sqrt{\Theta'}$, (A', B' rational functions of θ').

[511]

511. ADDITION TO THE MEMOIR ON GEODESIC LINES, IN PARTICULAR THOSE OF A QUADRIC SURFACE (509)

[From the *Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society*, vol. iv. (1871–1873), pp. 368–380. Read June 12, 1873.]

38. In the Memoir above referred to, speaking of the geodesic lines on the skew hyperboloid, I say (No. 35), “The geodesic of initial direction $M1$ touches at M the oval curve of curvature $M1$, and lies wholly above this curve; it makes an infinity of convolutions round the upper part of the hyperboloid, cutting all the oval curves of curvature for which p has a positive value greater than p_1 (if p_1 is the value of p corresponding to the oval curve through M), and ascending to infinity.” The statement as to the infinity of convolutions is incorrect; I was led to it by the assumption that the geodesic could not touch any hyperbolic curve of curvature. The fact is, that it touches at infinity (has for asymptotes) in general two hyperbolic curves of curvature; viz. the geodesic descending from infinity in the direction of a hyperbolic curve of curvature, so as to touch the oval curve through M , again ascends to infinity in the direction of a hyperbolic curve of curvature (the same as the first-mentioned one, or a different curve), making in its whole course say k convolutions, where m is a positive finite number; if $k < 1$, there is no complete convolution, and when $k = 1$ or any integer number, then the two hyperbolic curves are one and the same curve; k is infinite only in the special case afterwards referred to in the same No. 35, where the oval curve of curvature is the ellipse which is a principal section of the hyperboloid, and does not even attain to the value 1 except for an oval curve exceedingly close to this ellipse. The error was on consideration obvious enough, though I was in fact led to perceive it by the numerical calculations about to be referred to, which gave me geodesics not making a complete convolution.

¹ The articles are numbered consecutively with those of the Memoir, (509).

39. I have effected, for a particular skew hyperboloid and oval curve of curvature thereof, the numerical calculations for laying down the geodesic lines which touch this curve of curvature. Taking in general the equation of the hyperboloid to be

$$\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} = 1,$$

and the θ -curve of curvature to be the intersection by the confocal surface

$$\frac{x^2}{a-\theta} + \frac{y^2}{b-\theta} + \frac{z^2}{c-\theta} = 1,$$

then the selected values for the hyperboloid, and oval curve of curvature touched by the geodesics, are

$$a = 900, \quad b = 400, \quad c = -c' = -1600, \quad \theta = -\theta' = -1650;$$

so that a, b, c', θ' are the positive values 900, 400, 1600, and 1650 respectively. I recall that $p = c'$ to $p = \infty$ gives the oval curves of curvature, viz. $p = c'$, the elliptic principal section; $p = \theta'$, the given oval curve: and that we are in the sequel concerned only with the oval curves above this, for which p extends from θ' to ∞ . Moreover, $q = -b$ to $-a$ gives the hyperbolic curves of curvature, viz. $q = -b$ the xz -principal section; and $q = -a$ the yz -principal section of the hyperboloid. We have, in fact, to deal with the integrals

$$\Pi(p) = \int_{\theta'}^p dp \sqrt{\frac{p}{(p+a)(p+b)(p-c')(p-\theta')}},$$

$$\Psi(q) = \int_{-b}^q dq \sqrt{\frac{q}{(q+a)(q+b)(q-c')(q-\theta')}},$$

or if $p = \theta' + u$, u extending from 0 towards ∞ , then

$$\Pi(p) = \int_0^u du \sqrt{\frac{u+\theta'}{(u+a+\theta')(u+b+\theta')(u+\theta'-c')u}},$$

and so if $q = -b - v$, v extending from 0 towards $(a-b)$, which is its limit,

$$\Psi(q) = \int_0^v dv \sqrt{\frac{v+b}{(a-b-v)v(v+b+c')(v+b+\theta')}}.$$

The relation for any particular geodesic of the series being

$$\pm\Pi(p) + \Psi(q) = C.$$

40. To avoid discontinuity as to sign, it is convenient to take the integral $\Psi(q)$ in a particular manner. The hyperboloid is by the xz - and yz -principal planes divided into four quadrants; or since we attend only to the upper half of the hyperboloid, say this upper half is thus divided into four quadrants, x to y , y to x' , x' to y' , and y' to x ; or call them the first, second, third, and fourth quadrants. But we may consider the quadrants as forming an infinite succession, first, second, third, fourth, fifth, and so on; or we may take them in the reverse order, $-1, -2, -3, \&c.$ For a hyperbolic curve $q = -b - v$ in the first quadrant the integral is to be taken $v = 0$ to $v = v$; for a curve in the second quadrant $v = 0$ to $a - b$, and thence positively $a - b$ to v ; for a curve in the third quadrant $v = 0$ to $a - b$, thence $a - b$ to 0, and thence 0 to v ; and so on: and so for a point in the quadrant -1 , the integral is from 0 to v , taken negatively, $\&c.$; that is, as the hyperbolic curve travels from the xz -position in the positive direction, the integral $\Psi(q)$ continually increases from zero; and if the curve travels from the xz -position in the negative direction, then the integral $\Psi(q)$ continually

decreases from zero; that is, it increases negatively. It is to be remarked that the integral $v = 0$ to $a - b$ is finite, say it is $= K'$; and of course it is only thus far that the integral requires to be calculated, the subsequent values differing from the preceding ones only by multiples of this complete integral.

The integral $\Pi(p)$ requires no explanation; it is taken from $u = 0$, giving a certain oval curve, up to any positive value of u , giving the oval curves above this one; and, in particular, taking the integral to $u = \infty$ (or, what is the same thing, to $p = \infty$) its value is finite, $= K$, suppose.

41. Consider the geodesic which touches the given oval curve at a point for which $\Psi(q)$ has a given value Q ; at this point $p = \theta'$, or $\Pi(p) = 0$; so that, taking for the equation of the geodesic $\Psi(q) \pm \Pi(p) = C$, we have $Q = C$, and consequently

$$\Psi(q) = Q \mp \Pi(p).$$

Taking the positive sign, then as p increases from θ' , $\Psi(q)$ increases, or the describing point of the geodesic moves upwards from the point of contact in the direction of positive rotation; and taking the negative sign, then $\Psi(q)$ decreases, or the describing point of the geodesic moves upwards from the point of contact in the direction of negative rotation; and, in particular, p becoming infinite, then the first-mentioned branch touches at infinity the hyperbolic curve, for which q is such that $\Psi(q) = Q + K$, and the second branch that for which q is such that $\Psi(q) = Q - K$.

42. The graphical process is as follows: we describe, on the hyperboloid, a series of hyperbolic curves of curvature, numbering them according to the values of $\Psi(q)$; viz. considering the hyperbolic branches which form the $xz, yz, x'z$ and $y'z$ sections respectively, these are $0, K', 2K', 3K'$, and on going round a second time they would be $4K', 5K', 6K', 7K'$, and so on respectively. We similarly describe, say on the upper half of the hyperboloid, the oval curves of curvature, numbering them according to the values of $\Pi(p)$, viz. beginning with that for which $p = \theta'$, which is 0 , we go successively up to the oval curve at infinity, which is K .

In the example, and drawing belonging thereto, where, for convenience, the values of the integrals have been multiplied by 100,000, we have, as will appear, $K = 12490$, $K' = 34726$: the two sets of curves are drawn at intervals of 2000; viz. we have the hyperbolic curves $0, 2000, 4000, \dots, 34000, 34726$; and the oval curves $0, 2000, 4000, 6000, 8000, 10000$; the distance of the successive oval curves increases very rapidly, since the curve at infinity would be $K = 12490$, and the curve $K = 10000$ is the last which comes into the limits of the figure.

¹ This drawing was exhibited at the meeting of the Society.

43. The two sets of curves of curvature being thus drawn at equal intervals of $\Pi(p)$ and $\Psi(q)$ respectively, dividing the hyperboloid into quadrilateral spaces (which of course should theoretically be indefinitely small), the diagonals of these quadrilateral spaces are the elements of the geodesic lines; and by a series of such elements we have a particular geodesic line. The general character comes out in the drawing very distinctly; viz. the geodesic is a hyperbola-like curve descending from infinity to touch the oval curve, and again ascending to infinity; by reason of the small value of K in comparison of K' , there is nothing like a complete convolution, but the whole curve is included within a quadrant of the hyperboloid.

44. I remark that the calculations were performed roughly. I made no attempt to estimate or allow for errors arising from the intervals being too great; and there are very probably accidental errors of calculation. But starting with the value 10411 of $\Pi(p)$ for $p = 10000$, I found, with some care, superior and inferior limits of the remainder of the integral, $p = 10000$ to $p = \infty$; and the process is, I think, an interesting one. Consider in general the integral

$$\begin{aligned} I &= \int_{\theta'}^{\infty} dp \sqrt{\frac{p}{(p+a)(p+b)(p-c')(p-\theta')}} \\ &= I_1 + \int_{p_1}^{\infty} dp \sqrt{\frac{p}{(p+a)(p+b)(p-c')(p-\theta')}} \end{aligned}$$

where I_1 is the integral calculated up to a somewhat large value $p = p_1$.

Writing

$$\alpha = \frac{1}{2}(a+b), \quad \beta = \frac{1}{2}(c'+\theta'), \quad \gamma = \frac{1}{2}(a+b) - m, \quad \delta = \frac{1}{2}(c'+\theta') + n,$$

where m and n are as yet undetermined, we have

$$(p+a)(p+b) = (p+\alpha)^2 - \frac{1}{4}(a-b)^2 > (p+\alpha)^2,$$

$$(p-c')(p-\theta') = (p-\beta)^2 - \frac{1}{4}(\theta'-c')^2 > (p-\beta)^2;$$

and the integral is thus

$$> I_1 + \int_{p_1}^{\infty} dp \frac{\sqrt{p}}{(p+\alpha)(p-\beta)}.$$

But we may determine m and n , so that for $p =$ or $> p_1$,

$$(p+a)(p+b) < (p+\gamma)^2, \quad (p-c')(p-\theta') < (p-\delta)^2;$$

and the integral is then

$$< I_1 + \int_{p_1}^{\infty} dp \frac{\sqrt{p}}{(p+\gamma)(p-\delta)}.$$

The determination thus depends on the last-mentioned integrals, the values of which are at once obtainable by writing $\sqrt{p} = x$; viz. we have

$$\int dp \frac{\sqrt{p}}{(p+\alpha)(p-\beta)} = 2 \int \frac{x^2 dx}{(x^2+\alpha)(x^2-\beta)} = C + \frac{2}{\alpha+\beta} \left\{ \frac{1}{2} \sqrt{\beta} h \cdot l \frac{x-\sqrt{\beta}}{x+\sqrt{\beta}} + \frac{2\sqrt{\alpha}}{\alpha+\beta} \tan^{-1} \frac{x}{\sqrt{\alpha}} \right\}.$$

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and hence, substituting in the formula, for h. l. x its value $\frac{\log x}{\log e}$, the superior limit is

$$I_1 + \left\{ \frac{\sqrt{\delta}}{\gamma + \delta} \frac{1}{\log e} \log \frac{\sqrt{p_1} + \sqrt{\delta}}{\sqrt{p_1} - \sqrt{\delta}} + \frac{2\sqrt{\gamma}}{\gamma + \delta} \cot^{-1} \frac{\sqrt{p_1}}{\sqrt{\gamma_1}} \right\},$$

and the inferior limit is

$$I_1 + \left\{ \frac{\sqrt{\beta}}{\alpha + \beta} \frac{1}{\log e} \log \frac{\sqrt{p_1} + \sqrt{\beta}}{\sqrt{p_1} - \sqrt{\beta}} + \frac{2\sqrt{\alpha}}{\alpha + \beta} \cot^{-1} \frac{\sqrt{p_1}}{\sqrt{\alpha_1}} \right\}.$$

45. The numerical values are

$$p_1 = 10,000; \quad a, b, c', \theta' = 900, 400, 1600, 1650;$$

and thence determining by trial values of m and n ,

$$\alpha = 650, \quad \gamma = 650 - 4 = 646, \quad \beta = 1625, \quad \delta = 1625 + 160 = 1785.$$

I obtained for the logarithmic and circular terms of the two limits respectively

	Superior	Inferior
Logarithmic	.015668	.015144
Circular	.005202	.005593
	<u>.020870</u>	<u>.020737</u>

The value of I_1 was $10411 \div 100,000 = .104110$, and the two limits thus are .124980 and .124850; or restoring the factor 100,000, they are 12498 and 12485; the mean of these, say 12490, was taken for the value $\Pi(p)$, $p = \infty$; that is $K = 12490$.

46. As regards the calculation of the integrals $\Pi(p)$ and $\Psi(q)$, introducing the numerical values, and multiplying by the before-mentioned factor 100,000, we have ($q = -400 - v$),

$$\Psi(q) = 100,000 \int_0^v dv \sqrt{\frac{v + 400}{(500 - v)v(v + 2000)(v + 2050)}}.$$

which for any small value of v is

$$= 100,000 \sqrt{\frac{400}{500 \cdot 2000 \cdot 2050}} \left(\int \frac{dv}{\sqrt{v}} = 2\sqrt{v} \right);$$

viz. this is

$$= 883.45 (\log = 2.9461830) \sqrt{v},$$

which was used for the values $v = 1, 2, \dots, 10$, that is, to $q = -410$; after which the calculation was continued by quadratures giving to v the values 10, 20, 30, ... up to $v = 490$, or $q = -890$. For the remainder of the integral, writing $500 - v = w$ (that is, $q = -900 + w$), we have

$$\begin{aligned} \Psi(q) - \Psi(-890) &= 100,000 \int dw \sqrt{\frac{900 - w}{w(500 - w)(2500 - w)(2550 - w)}}, \\ &= 100,000 \sqrt{\frac{900}{500 \cdot 2500 \cdot 2550}} \left\{ \int \frac{dw}{\sqrt{w}} = 2(\sqrt{10} - \sqrt{w}) \right\} \\ &= 1062.7 (\log = 3.0264261)(\sqrt{10} - \sqrt{w}). \end{aligned}$$

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This was used for the values $w = 9, 8, 7, \dots, 1, 0$, to complete the calculation up to $q = -900$.

47. We have in like manner, $p = 1650 + u$,

$$\Pi(p) = 100000 \int_0^u du \sqrt{\frac{u + 1650}{(u + 2550)(u + 2050)(u + 50)u}},$$

which for small values of u is

$$= 100000 \sqrt{\frac{1650}{2550 \cdot 2050 \cdot 50}},$$

viz. this is

$$502.5 \quad (\log = 2.7011399),$$

used for $u = 1, 2, \dots, 10$, that is to $p = 1660$. The calculation was afterwards continued by quadratures, by giving to u a succession of values, at intervals at first of 10, and afterwards of 20, 50, 100, 200, and 500, up to $p = 10,000$, giving for the integral the value 10411; and thence, as appearing above, the value for $p = \infty$ was found to be = 12490.

48. After the calculation of the values of $\Pi(p)$ and $\Psi(q)$, it was easy by interpolation to revert these tables, so as to obtain a table which, for Π or Ψ as argument, gives the values of p and q . The arguments are taken at intervals of 500; up to 10000 as regards p , since the original table was only calculated thus far; and up to 34726 as regards q . I had thus calculated the annexed Table III., when it occurred to me that there was a convenience in taking the arguments to be submultiples of the complete integral 34726; say we divide this into 90 parts, or, as it were, graduate the quadrant of the hyperboloid by means of hyperbolic curves of curvature adapted for the geodesics in question. Taking every fifth part, or in fact dividing the quadrant into 18 parts, we have the Table IV.

49. It will be remembered that the foregoing results apply only to the geodesics which touch the oval curve of curvature $p = +1650$; for the geodesics touching any other oval curve of curvature, the values of the integrals, and the mutual distances of the curves of curvature used for tracing the geodesics, would be completely altered. But it is possible to derive some general conclusions as to the geodesics that touch a given oval curve of curvature.

Observe that the integral K' (= 34726 in the case considered) measures the quadrant of the hyperboloid; viz. $\Psi(q) = 0, \Psi(q) = K'$ determine two hyperbolic curves of curvature (principal sections), the mutual distance whereof is a quadrant. Each geodesic touches the given oval curve of curvature, and it touches at infinity the two hyperbolic curves $\Psi(q) = Q \pm K$ ($K = 12490$ in the case considered); viz. the distance of these curves, in regard to the circuit of four quadrants, or say the amplitude of the geodesic, is measured by the ratio $\frac{K}{2K'}$.

50. Now it is easy to see that as the oval curve of curvature approaches the principal elliptic section, that is, as θ' approaches c' (or writing $\theta' = c' + m$, as m

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diminishes towards zero), the integral K' alters its value only slowly, increasing towards a certain constant limit; but, contrariwise, K increases without limit, its value for any small value of m being of the form $A - B \log m$, = ∞ in the limit; wherefore, as m diminishes, the value of $\frac{K}{2K'}$, the amplitude of the geodesic, continually increases. If this is = 1, the geodesic touching at infinity a certain hyperbolic curve of curvature, in descending to touch the oval curve, makes round the hyperboloid a half-convolution, and then again ascends through another half-convolution to touch at infinity the same hyperbolic curve of curvature; viz. it makes in all one entire convolution, or say in descending it makes a half-convolution. But if $K \div 2K' = 2$, then the curve makes in descending a complete convolution; and so, if $K \div 2K' = 2s$, then the geodesic makes in descending s convolutions; and, as already mentioned, ultimately when $m = 0$ the geodesic makes an infinity of convolutions; that is, it never actually reaches the elliptic principal section, but has this line for an asymptote.

51. To sustain the foregoing statements, I write $\theta' (= c' + m) = 1600 + m$, and I consider the integral

$$K'_m = 100000 \int_0^\infty du \sqrt{\frac{u + 1600 + m}{(u + 2500 + m)(u + 2000 + m)(u + m)u}},$$

say for a moment this is

$$K'_m = \int_0^\infty U_m du.$$

Supposing m to be small, we divide the integral into two parts, say from 0 to a [where a , = for example 50 or 100, is large in comparison with m , but small in comparison with the numbers (c' , &c.), 1600, &c.], and from a to ∞ . In the second part, the expression under the integral sign and the value of the integral varies slowly with m , and we may, as an approximation, write $m = 0$. We have thus

$$K_m = \int_0^a U_m du + \int_a^\infty U_0 du,$$

and the first part hereof is

$$= 100000 \sqrt{\frac{1600}{2500 \cdot 2000}} \int_0^a \frac{du}{\sqrt{u(u+m)}}.$$

viz. the integral is here

$$\text{h. l. } \{u + \tfrac{1}{2}m + \sqrt{u(u+m)}\} = \text{h. l. } \frac{a + \tfrac{1}{2}m + \sqrt{a(a+m)}}{\tfrac{1}{2}m} = \text{h. l. } \frac{4a}{m} \quad \text{approximately;}$$

or say this is

$$= \frac{1}{\log e} \log \frac{4a}{m}.$$

The first term is thus

$$= 100000 \sqrt{\frac{1600}{2500 \cdot 2000}} \frac{1}{\log e} \log \frac{4a}{m},$$

which is

$$= 4119 \log \frac{4a}{m}.$$

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or we have

$$K'_m = 4119 \log \frac{4a}{m} + \int_a^\infty U_0 du.$$

We ought to have the same value of the integral, whatever, within proper limits, the assumed value of a may be. Taking, for instance, $a = 50$ and $a = 100$, we ought to have

$$K'_m = 4119 \log \frac{400}{m} + \int_{100}^\infty U_0 du = 4119 \log \frac{200}{m} + \int_{50}^\infty U_0 du;$$

that is,

$$4119 \log 2 = \int_{50}^{100} U_0 du.$$

In verification, I calculated the second side by quadratures; viz. for the values .50, 60, 70, 80, 90, 100, the values of U_0 are

$$35.532, \quad 29.570, \quad 25.311, \quad 22.373, \quad 19.632, \quad 17.645;$$

whence, adding the half sum of the extreme terms to the sum of the mean terms, and multiplying by 10, the value of the integral is = 1234.74. The value of the left-hand side is = 1239.94, which is a sufficient agreement.

52. Returning to the formula for K'_m , this may be written

$$K'_m = \left(4119 \log 400 + \int_{100}^{\infty} U_0 du \right) - 4119 \log m.$$

I did not calculate the value of the integral in this formula, but determined the term in () in such wise that the formula should be correct for the foregoing value $m = 50$; viz. the term thus is

$$= 12490 + 4119 \log 50 = 12490 + 6998, = 19488,$$

or say 19500; we thus have

$$K_m = 19500 - 4119 \log m;$$

and we may roughly assume that, for any small value of m , K'_m has the same value as for $m = 50$; viz. we may write

$$K'_m = 34726, \quad \text{or say } = 35000.$$

We thus see how to give to m such a value that the quantity $\frac{K}{2K'}$, which is the number of convolutions of the geodesic, may have any given value; and, in particular, we see how exceedingly small m must be for any moderately large number of convolutions; for instance, $m = \frac{1}{100000000}$, or $\log m = -8$,

$K = 19500 + 32952, = \text{say } 52500$, or the number is $= \frac{52500}{70000}$, about five-sevenths of a convolution.

CORRECTION. Instead of speaking, as above, of a geodesic as touching at infinity a hyperbolic curve of curvature, the accurate expression is that the geodesic at infinity is parallel to a certain hyperbolic curve of curvature. The geodesic has, in fact, for asymptote the right line on the surface parallel at infinity to such curve of curvature. Added Dec. 1873.

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TABLE I.	
p	$\Pi(p)$
1650	000
1	502
2	711
3	870
4	1005
5	1124
6	1231
7	1329
8	1421
9	1507
1660	1589
70	2188
80	2605
90	2933
1700	3205
10	3438
20	3642
30	3824
40	3989
50	4130
60	4287
70	4414
80	4532
90	4642
1800	4745
20	4945
40	5106
60	5261
80	5403
1900	5533
20	5654
40	5766
60	5871
80	5970
2000	6063
50	6275
100	6462
150	6629
200	6779
250	6916
300	7041
350	7156
400	7262
450	7362

TABLE II.	
q	$\Psi(q)$
-400	000
1	883
2	1249
3	1530
4	1767
5	1975
6	2164
7	2337
8	2499
9	2650
410	2794
20	4016
30	4952
40	5752
50	6467
60	7124
70	7739
80	8321
90	8877
500	9413
10	9931
20	10436
30	10923
40	11406
50	11880
60	12347
70	12809
80	13266
90	13720
600	14171
10	14619
20	15067
30	15513
40	15960
50	16408
60	16857
70	17308
80	17762
90	18220
700	18682
10	19149
20	19623
30	20101
-40	20588

TABLE I. (CONTINUED).

p	$\Pi(p)$
2500	7454
600	7625
700	7777
800	7913
900	8037
3000	8151
200	8352
400	8526
600	8679
800	8815
4000	8936
500	9216
5000	9423
500	9593
6000	9737
500	9861
7000	9970
500	10066
8000	10152
500	10229
9000	10299
500	10363
10000	10411
$\vdots$	
∞	12490

TABLE II. (CONTINUED).

q	$\Psi(q)$
-750	21086
60	21595
70	22117
80	22653
90	23206
800	23778
10	24374
20	24998
30	25655
40	26355
50	27105
60	27928
70	28861
80	29936
890	31365
1	31538
2	31720
3	31914
4	32123
5	32350
6	32600
7	32886
8	33224
9	33663
-900	34726

TABLE III.

Π or Ψ	p	Diff.	q	Diff.
0	1650.0	1	-400.0	.3
500	1651.0	3	400.3	1.0
1000	1654.0	5	401.3	1.6
1500	1659.0	7.8	402.9	2.2
2000	1666.8	10.7	405.1	2.9
2500	1677.5	14.9	408.0	3.7
3000	1692.4	20.6	411.7	4.0
3500	1713.0	27.8	415.7	4.3
4000	1740.8	36.6	420.0	5.2
4500	1777.4	49.4	425.2	5.4
5000	1826.8	68.1	430.6	6.2
5500	1894.9	91.5	436.8	6.6
6000	1986.4	124.6	-443.4	7.1

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TABLE III. (CONTINUED).

Π or Ψ	p	Diff.	q	Diff.
6500	2111	124.6	-450.5	7.1
7000	2283	172	458.1	7.6
7500	2527	244	466.1	8.0
8000	2870	353	474.5	8.4
8500	3285	415	483.2	8.7
9000	4114	829	492.3	9.1
9500	5226	1112	501.7	9.4
10000	7156	1930	511.3	9.6
10500	.		521.1	9.8
11000	.		531.5	10.1
11500	.		542.0	10.5
12000	.		552.5	10.8
12500	∞		563.3	10.8
13000			574.2	10.9
13500			585.1	10.9
14000			596.2	11.1
14500			607.3	11.1
15000			618.5	11.2
15500			629.7	11.2
16000			641.0	11.3
16500			652.1	11.1
17000			663.2	11.1
17500			674.2	11.0
18000			685.2	11.0
18500			696.1	10.9
19000			706.8	10.7
19500			717.4	10.6
20000			728.0	10.6
20500			738.4	10.4
21000			748.3	9.9
21500			758.1	9.8
22000			767.7	9.6
22500			777.4	9.4
23000			786.4	9.0
23500			795.1	8.7
24000			803.7	8.6
24500			812.0	8.3
25000			820.0	8.0
25500			827.6	7.6
26000			834.9	7.3
26500			-841.9	7.0

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TABLE III. (CONTINUED).

Π or Ψ	p	Diff.	q	Diff.
27000			-848.6	6.7
27500			854.8	6.2
28000			860.8	6.0
28500			866.1	5.3
29000			871.3	5.2
29500			876.0	4.7
30000			880.6	4.6
30500			884.0	3.4
31000			887.5	3.5
31500			890.8	3.3
32000			893.4	3.6
32500			895.6	2.2
33000			897.5	1.7
33500			898.6	1.1
34000			899.3	0.7
34500			899.8	0.5
34726			-900	0.2

TABLE IV.

	Π or Ψ	p	Diff.	q	Diff.
0	0	1650		-400	
1	1929	1665.7	15.7	404.8	4.8
2	3858	1732.1	66.4	418.7	13.9
3	5788	1944.2	212.1	440.5	21.8
4	7717	2657.7	713.5	469.6	29.1
5	9646	5697.7	3040.0	504.5	34.9
6	11575			543.6	39.1
7	13504			585.2	41.6
8	15434			628.0	42.8
9	17363			671.2	43.2
10	19292			713.0	41.8
11	21221			752.7	39.7
12	23150			789.0	36.3
13	25079			821.2	32.2
14	27008			848.6	27.4
15	28938			870.7	22.1
16	30868			886.5	15.8
17	32797			896.7	10.2
18	34726			-900	3.3

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512.

ON A CORRESPONDENCE OF POINTS IN RELATION TO TWO TETRAHEDRA.

[From the Proceedings of the London Mathematical Society, vol. IV. (1871–1873), pp. 396–404. Read June 12, 1873.]

The following question has been considered by R. Sturm in an interesting paper, “Das Problem der Projectivität und seine Anwendung auf die Flächen zweiten Grades,” Math. Ann., t. I. (1870), pp. 533–574: Given in piano two groups of the same number (5, 6, or 7) of points, to find points P , P' homographically related to these two groups respectively; viz. the lines from P to the points of the first group and those from P' to the points of the second group are to be homographic pencils. In the present paper I require only a particular form of these results; viz. in each group two of the points are the circular points at infinity; or, disregarding these, we have two groups of 3, 4, or 5 points such that the points of the first group at P , and those of the second group at P' , subtend equal angles. I give for this particular case an independent analytical investigation; but I will first state the results included in the more general ones obtained by Sturm.

If the points A, B, C at P and the points A', B', C' at P' subtend equal angles, then to any given position of the one point corresponds a single position of the other point; viz. the two points have a (1, 1) correspondence; the nature of this being, that to any line in the one figure corresponds in the other figure a quintic curve, having 6 dps.; viz. the three points, the two circular points at infinity I, J , and one other fixed point of that figure (say for the first figure this fixed point is (ABC)).

If the points A, B, C, D at P and the points A', B', C', D' at P' subtend equal angles, then the locus of each point is a cubic curve; viz. the locus of P passes through A, B, C, D, I, J and the four fixed points $(ABC), (ABD), (ACD), (BCD)$; and the like for the locus of P' .

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Finally (although this is a theorem which I do not require), if the points A, B, C, D, E at P and the points A', B', C', D', E' at P' subtend equal angles, then there are three positions of each point.

The problem I propose to consider is: Given the tetrahedra $ABCD$ and $A'B'C'D'$, it is required in the planes ABC and $A'B'C'$ respectively to find the points P, P' such that A, B, C, D at P , and A', B', C', D' at P' , subtend equal angles. I was led to this by the more general problem, which I do not at present discuss: Given the two tetrahedra, it is required to find the loci of the points P, P' such that A, B, C, D at P , and A', B', C', D' at P' , subtend equal angles.

Here, drawing from D, D' the perpendiculars $DK, D'K'$ on the planes ABC and $A'B'C'$ respectively, we have A, B, C, K at P , and A', B', C', K' at P' , subtending equal angles, and such that the distances PK and $P'K'$ are proportional to the heights of the tetrahedra (for the triangles PDK and $P'D'K'$ are obviously similar). The required points P, P' are each the intersection of two loci, viz.:

1. P is such that A, B, C, K at P , and A', B', C', K' at P' , subtend equal angles; locus is a cubic through $A, B, C, K, I, J, (ABC), (ABK), (ACK), (BCK)$.
2. P is such that A, B, K at P , and A', B', K' at P' , subtend equal angles, and that PK and $P'K'$ are in a given ratio; locus is a certain octic curve.

and the required positions of P are obtained as the intersections of the two loci.

I proceed to the analytical investigation.

Preliminary Formulæ.

1. Consider a triangle ABC , and let the position of a point P be determined by means of its coordinates x, y, z , which are equal to the perpendicular distances of P from the sides, each divided by the perpendicular distance of the opposite vertex (as usual, x, y, z are positive for a point within the triangle); or what is the same thing, $x, y, z = PBC, PCA, PAB$, divided each by ABC , whence identically

$$1 = x + y + z.$$

Suppose for a moment the rectangular coordinates of A, B, C are $(\alpha_1, \beta_1), (\alpha_2, \beta_2), (\alpha_3, \beta_3)$ respectively; and that those of P are X, Y . Also let the sides BC, CA, AB be $= a, b, c$ respectively. We have

$$X = \alpha_1 x + \alpha_2 y + \alpha_3 z, \quad Y = \beta_1 x + \beta_2 y + \beta_3 z, \quad 1 = x + y + z.$$

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and if we consider a second point P' , the coordinates of which are x', y', z' and X', Y' , we have the like relations between these quantities. Calling δ the distance of the two points P, P' , we may write

$$\begin{aligned} \delta^2 = & \{\alpha_1(x - x') + \alpha_2(y - y') + \alpha_3(z - z')\}^2 \\ & + \{\beta_1(x - x') + \beta_2(y - y') + \beta_3(z - z')\}^2 \\ & - \{(\alpha_1^2 + \beta_1^2)(x - x') + (\alpha_2^2 + \beta_2^2)(y - y') + (\alpha_3^2 + \beta_3^2)(z - z')\} \\ & \times \{(x - x') + (y - y') + (z - z')\}, \end{aligned}$$

the last term being in fact $= 0$; viz. this is

$$\begin{aligned} \delta^2 = & -\{(\alpha_2 - \alpha_3)^2 + (\beta_2 - \beta_3)^2\}(y - y')(z - z') \\ & - \{(\alpha_3 - \alpha_1)^2 + (\beta_3 - \beta_1)^2\}(z - z')(x - x') \\ & - \{(\alpha_1 - \alpha_2)^2 + (\beta_1 - \beta_2)^2\}(x - x')(y - y'); \end{aligned}$$

or what is the same thing, the expression for the distance δ^2 of the two points P, P' is

$$\delta^2 = -a^2(y - y')(z - z') - b^2(z - z')(x - x') - c^2(x - x')(y - y').$$

This expression may be modified by means of the identical equations

$$1 = x + y + z, \quad 1 = x' + y' + z';$$

viz. writing

$$yz' - y'z = \xi, \quad zx' - z'x = \eta, \quad xy' - x'y = \zeta,$$

we have

$$x - x' = \xi - \eta, \quad y - y' = \zeta - \xi, \quad z - z' = \eta - \zeta.$$

2. Treating x', y', z' as constants and x, y, z as current coordinates, the formula for δ^2 is of course the equation of a circle, centre x', y', z' and radius δ . It thus also appears that the general equation of a circle is

$$-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy + (Lx + My + Nz)(x + y + z) = 0;$$

viz. writing $-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy = U$, and $x + y + z = \Omega$, this is

$$U + (Lx + My + Nz)\Omega = 0,$$

where $U = 0$ is the circle circumscribed about the triangle ABC , and $\Omega = 0$ is the line infinity. Of course the general equation of a circle passing through the points

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(B, C) is $U + Lx\Omega = 0$, and similarly those of circles through (C, A) and through (A, B) are $U + My\Omega = 0$ and $U + Nz\Omega = 0$ respectively. But we require the interpretation of the coefficients L, M, N which enter into these equations.

3. Considering the triangle ABC , if through B, C we have a circle, this is by the side BC divided into two segments, and I consider that lying on the same side with A as the positive segment, and define the angle of the circle to be the angle in this positive segment. It is clear that if we have within the triangle a point P , and, through this point and $(B, C), (C, A), (A, B)$ respectively, three circles, then if α, β, γ be the angles of these circles, we have $\alpha + \beta + \gamma = 2\pi$; and conversely, if the circles through $(B, C), (C, A), (A, B)$ are such that their angles α, β, γ satisfy the relation $\alpha + \beta + \gamma = 2\pi$, then the three circles meet in a point. But it is further to be noticed, that if, producing the sides of the triangle so as to divide the plane into seven spaces, the triangle, three trilaterals, and three bilaterals, we take the point P within one of the bilaterals, we still have $\alpha + \beta + \gamma = 2\pi$; but taking it within one of the trilaterals, we have $\alpha + \beta + \gamma = \pi$. And the converse theorem is, that if the three circles $(B, C), (C, A), (A, B)$ are such that $\alpha + \beta + \gamma = \pi$ or 2π , then the circles meet in a point; viz. if the sum is 2π , then this point lies in the triangle or one of the bilaterals; but if the sum is $= \pi$, then this point lies in a trilateral.

4. I seek for the equation of a circle through the points B, C , and containing the angle L . In rectangular coordinates this is

$$(X - \alpha_2)(X - \alpha_3) + (Y - \beta_2)(Y - \beta_3) - \{(\alpha_2 - \alpha_3)Y - (\beta_2 - \beta_3)X + \alpha_2\beta_3 - \alpha_3\beta_2\} \cot L = 0.$$

In fact this is the equation of a circle through (B, C) ; and taking for a moment the origin at B , and axis of X to coincide with BC , or writing $\alpha_2, \beta_2 = 0, 0$; $\alpha_3, \beta_3 = a, 0$, the equation is

$$X(X - a) + Y^2 - aY \cot L = 0,$$

viz. the equation of the tangent at B is $-aX - aY \cot L = 0$, that is, $Y = -X \tan L$, or the angle in the positive segment is $= L$.

If for a moment λ, μ, ν are the inclinations of the sides of the triangle ABC to the axis of X , then A, B, C being the angles, we may write

$$\mu - \nu = \pi - A, \quad \nu - \lambda = \pi - B, \quad \lambda - \mu = -\pi - C,$$

and

$$\begin{aligned} X - \alpha_2 &= c \cos \nu x - a \cos \lambda z, & X - \alpha_3 &= -b \cos \mu x + a \cos \lambda y, \\ Y - \beta_2 &= c \sin \nu x - a \sin \lambda z, & Y - \beta_3 &= -b \sin \mu x + a \sin \lambda y. \end{aligned}$$

whence the preceding circle equation becomes

$$-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy + bc \cos A x^2 + (b^2 - ab \cos C)zx + (c^2 - ac \cos B)xy;$$

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viz. this is

$$= -a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy + bc \cos A x(x + y + z).$$

Moreover, if $\Delta =$ twice the area of the triangle, then

$$(\beta_2 - \beta_3)X - (\alpha_2 - \alpha_3)Y + \alpha_2\beta_3 - \alpha_3\beta_2 = \Delta x(x + y + z) = bc \sin A x(x + y + z);$$

so that the equation becomes

$$-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy + bc \sin A (\cot A - \cot L)x(x + y + z) = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy + \Delta(\cot A - \cot L)x(x + y + z) = 0,$$

or, if we please,

$$-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy + \Delta(\cot A - \cot L)x = 0.$$

Writing as before,

$$-a^2yz - b^2zx - c^2xy = U, \quad x + y + z = \Omega,$$

the equation is

$$U + \Delta(\cot A - \cot L)\Omega x = 0.$$

Forming the like equations of two other similar circles, we have the circles $(B, C), (C, A), (A, B)$ containing the angles L, M, N respectively; and the equations are

$$U + \Delta(\cot A - \cot L)\Omega x = 0, \quad U + \Delta(\cot B - \cot M)\Omega y = 0, \quad U + \Delta(\cot C - \cot N)\Omega z = 0.$$

Correspondence, A, B, C at P , and A', B', C' at P' , subtending equal angles.

5. Consider now the two figures A', B', C' , subtending at P' the same angles L, M, N which A, B, C subtend at P ; then we have

$$\frac{U}{\Delta\Omega x} = \cot L - \cot A, \quad \frac{U}{\Delta\Omega y} = \cot M - \cot B, \quad \frac{U}{\Delta\Omega z} = \cot N - \cot C,$$

and similarly for the accented figure.

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Consequently

$$\frac{x'}{x} : \frac{y'}{y} : \frac{z'}{z} = \frac{U'}{U + \Delta(\cot A - \cot A')\Omega x} : \frac{U'}{U + \Delta(\cot B - \cot B')\Omega y} : \frac{U'}{U + \Delta(\cot C - \cot C')\Omega z},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$x' : y' : z' = \frac{x}{U + \Delta(\cot A - \cot A')\Omega x} : \frac{y}{U + \Delta(\cot B - \cot B')\Omega y} : \frac{z}{U + \Delta(\cot C - \cot C')\Omega z}.$$

Here observe that the equations

$$U + \Delta(\cot A - \cot A')\Omega x = 0, \quad U + \Delta(\cot B - \cot B')\Omega y = 0, \quad U + \Delta(\cot C - \cot C')\Omega z = 0$$

represent circles $(B, C), (C, A), (A, B)$ containing the angles A', B', C' ; and since $A' + B' + C' = \pi$, these meet in a point O . We may for convenience write

$$x' : y' : z' = \frac{BC}{BCO} : \frac{CA}{CAO} : \frac{AB}{ABO},$$

where $BC = 0$ denotes $(x = 0)$ the line BC ; $BCO = 0$ the circle through B, C, O . And of course, in like manner,

$$x : y : z = \frac{B'C'}{B'C'O'} : \frac{C'A'}{C'A'O'} : \frac{A'B'}{A'B'O'},$$

so that the points P, P' have a rational, or $(1, 1)$, correspondence.

Writing

$$x' : y' : z' = BC.CAO.ABO : CA.ABO.BCO : AB.BCO.CAO = X : Y : Z,$$

suppose X, Y, Z are quintic functions of x, y, z , and the curve in the first figure corresponding to the line $\alpha x' + \beta y' + \gamma z' = 0$ of the second figure is

$$\alpha X + \beta Y + \gamma Z = 0.$$

viz. this is a quintic curve having dps. at each of the points A, B, C, O, I, J . In fact, if for BCO we write $BCOIJ$, and so for the other two circles respectively, we have in an algorithm which will be at once understood

$$X = BC.CAOIJ.ABOIJ = (ABCOIJ)^2,$$

and similarly $Y = Z = (ABCOIJ)^2$, or the curve is $(ABCOIJ)^2 = 0$.

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Correspondence, A, B, C, D at P and A', B', C', D' at P' subtending equal angles.

6. Consider now in piano the points A, B, C, D which at P , and the points A', B', C', D' which at P' , subtend equal angles. Let a, b, c, f, g, h denote the perpendicular distances of P from the lines BC, CA, AB, AD, BD, CD respectively; and the like as to a', b', c', f', g', h' . Observe that, neglecting constant factors, a, b, c are what were before represented by x, y, z ; we may consider the coordinates of P in regard to the triangles ABC, BCD, CAD, ABD to be

$$(a, b, c), \quad (a, h, g), \quad (b, f, h), \quad (c, g, f)$$

respectively. We have in regard to ABC the point O as before, and in regard to BCD, CAD, ABD the points O_1, O_2, O_3 respectively. Then A, B, C at P and A', B', C' at P' subtending equal angles, we may write

$$a' : b' : c' = \frac{a}{BCO} : \frac{b}{CAO} : \frac{c}{ABO};$$

viz. $BCO = 0$ is here the circle through B, C, O , and the like for CAO and ABO , the expressions being multiplied into the proper constant factors to take account of the constant factors whereby a, b, c and a', b', c' differ from x, y, z and x', y', z' respectively.

We have in like manner

$$a' : h' : g' = \frac{a}{CDO_1} : \frac{h}{ADO_1} : \frac{g}{BDO_1},$$

and the analogous formulae for the triangles CAD and ABD . From the ratios of (f', g', h') , (b', c', f') , (c', a', g') , (a', b', h') respectively we deduce

$$\begin{aligned} CDO_1.ADO_2.BDO_3 - BDO_1.CDO_2.ADO_3 &= 0, \\ CAO.ABO_3.ADO_2 - ABO.ADO_3.CAO_2 &= 0, \\ ABO.BCO_1.BDO_3 - BCO.BDO_1.ABO_3 &= 0, \\ BCO.CAO_2.CDO_1 - CAO.CDO_2.BCO_1 &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

each of which equations represents a sextic curve; and admitting that it can be shown that these pass through O, O_1, O_2, O_3 respectively, the forms are

$$\begin{aligned} D^3ABCOO_1O_2O_3I^3J^3 &= 0, & DA^3BCOO_1O_2O_3I^3J^3 &= 0, \\ DAB^3COO_1O_2O_3I^3J^3 &= 0, & DABC^3OO_1O_2O_3I^3J^3 &= 0. \end{aligned}$$

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7. Now the locus of P is evidently a curve, and this can only happen by reason that the four left-hand functions contain a common factor, and the form of them suggests that this common factor

is $ABCD O_1 O_2 O_3 IJ$, the four extraneous factors being $D^2 I^2 J^2$, $A^2 I^2 J^2$, $B^2 I^2 J^2$, $C^2 I^2 J^2$; viz. $ABCD O_1 O_2 O_3 IJ = 0$ is a cubic curve passing through the ten points; and $D^2 I^2 J^2 = 0$ a cubic curve through each of the points D, I, J twice; viz. it is the triad of lines IJ, DI, DJ ; and the like as to the other extraneous factors $A^2 I^2 J^2$, $B^2 I^2 J^2$, and $C^2 I^2 J^2$. I have not worked out the analysis to verify this a posteriori; but, the conclusion agreeing with Sturm, I accept it without further investigation, viz. the result is that A, B, C, D at P and A', B', C', D' at P' subtending equal angles, the locus of P is a cubic curve $ABCD O_1 O_2 O_3 IJ = 0$ through the ten points thus represented; and of course the locus of P' is in like manner a cubic curve $A'B'C'D'O'_1 O'_2 O'_3 I'J' = 0$ through the ten points thus represented.

Correspondence, A, B, C, D, E at P and A', B', C', D', E' at P' subtending equal angles.

8. We may go a step further, and consider A, B, C, D, E at P and A', B', C', D', E' at P' subtending equal angles. Attending only to the points A, B, C, D and A', B', C', D' , the locus of P is a cubic curve

$$ABCD O_1 O_2 O_3 IJ = 0;$$

and similarly attending to the points A, B, C, E and A', B', C', E' , the locus of P is a cubic curve

$$ABCE OQ_1 Q_2 Q_3 IJ = 0.$$

(Observe that O , as depending only on A, B, C , is the same point as before; but that Q_1, Q_2, Q_3 , as depending on E instead of D , are not the same as O_1, O_2, O_3 .) The two cubic curves have in common the points A, B, C, I, J, O , and they consequently intersect in three other points; that is, there are three positions of the point P , and of course three corresponding positions of P' .

Correspondence, A, B, C at P and A', B', C' at P' subtending equal angles, and $AP, A'P'$ in a given ratio.

9. Consider, as before, A, B, C at P and A', B', C' at P' subtending equal angles, and the points P, P' being moreover such that the distances $AP, A'P'$ are in a given ratio. I write for shortness

$$x' : y' : z' = \frac{x}{L} : \frac{y}{M} : \frac{z}{N},$$

where L, M, N denote

$$U + \Delta(\cot A - \cot A')\Omega x, \quad U + \Delta(\cot B - \cot B')\Omega y, \quad U + \Delta(\cot C - \cot C')\Omega z,$$

respectively.

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We have, or what is the same thing,

$$(AP)^2 = c^2 y^2 + b^2 z^2 + 2bc \cos A yz;$$

and similarly

$$(A'P')^2 = c'^2 y'^2 + b'^2 z'^2 + 2b'c' \cos A' y'z'.$$

The required relation therefore is

$$\frac{c'^2 y'^2 + b'^2 z'^2 + 2b'c' \cos A' y'z'}{(x' + y' + z')^2} = \kappa^2 \frac{c^2 y^2 + b^2 z^2 + 2bc \cos A yz}{(x + y + z)^2};$$

viz. substituting for x', y', z' their values, this is

$$L^2(x + y + z)^2(b'^2 z'^2 N^2 + c'^2 y'^2 M^2 + 2b'c' yz MN \cos A')$$

$$= \kappa^2(b^2z^2 + c^2y^2 + 2bcyz \cos A)(xMN + yNL + zLM)^2,$$

which is an equation of the 12th order. I say that the points A, B, C, O, I, J are each quadruple. In fact, according to the foregoing algorithm, we may write

$$x + y + z = IJ, \quad zM = AB.CAOIJ, \quad \&c.,$$

$$xL = yM = zN = A^2BCOIJ, \quad y = z = A, \quad xMN = BC.CAOIJ.ABOIJ, \quad \&c.,$$

$$xMN = yNL = zLM = (ABCOIJ)^2;$$

and the equation is, that is,

$$(BCOIJ)^2(IJ)^2(A^2BCOIJ)^2 = \kappa^2 A^4 (ABCOIJ)^4,$$

$$(IJ)^2(ABCOIJ)^4 = \kappa^2 A^4 (ABCOIJ)^4;$$

so that the points are each quadruple.

The two Tetrahedra; A, B, C, D at P in ABC and A', B', C', D' at P' in $A'B'C'$ subtending equal angles.

10. I consider now the before-mentioned problem of the two tetrahedra; viz. on the two bases ABC and $A'B'C'$ respectively, letting fall the perpendiculars DK and $D'K'$, then first A, B, C, K at P and A', B', C', K' at P' subtend equal angles; the locus of P is a cubic curve $ABCKOO_1O_2O_3IJ = 0$ through these ten points. ($O = ABC$ is derived from the points A, B, C ; and in like manner $O_1 = BCK$, $O_2 = CAK$, $O_3 = ABK$.)

Next, B, C, K at P and B', C', K' at P' subtend equal angles, and moreover the distances KP and $K'P'$ are in a given ratio; the locus of P is a 12-thic curve

$$(BCKO_1IJ)^{12} = 0$$

having each of these six points as a quadruple point. Hence among the 36 intersections of the two curves we have the points B, C, K, O_1, I, J each 4 times, and there remain $36 - 24 = 12$ intersections.

The conclusion is that A, B, C, D at a point P of ABC , and A', B', C', D' at a point P' of $A'B'C'$, subtending equal angles, there are 12 positions of P , and of course 12 corresponding positions of P' .

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ON A BICYCLIC CHUCK.

[From the Philosophical Magazine, vol. XLIII. (1872), pp. 365–367.]

The apparatus, although I have called it a chuck, is constructed not for turning, but for drawing; viz. it rotates horizontally on a table (being moved, not from the inside by the axle of the lathe, but from the outside by a handle-frame), carrying a drawing-board which works under a fixed pencil supported by a bridge. Two points of the drawing-board describe circles; and the curve traced out on the drawing-board is consequently that described by a fixed point upon a moving plane two points of which describe circles; or, what is really the same thing, it is the curve described on a fixed plane by a point rigidly connected with two points each of which describes a circle. The apparatus is at once convertible into an oval chuck of nearly the ordinary construction; viz. it may be arranged so that the curve described on the drawing-board is an ellipse.

The construction is as follows. There is in the bottom plane a fixed plate, having two circular grooves with their centres A, B respectively; and in these grooves there work the segments (4) and the block (3), each capable of rotation about its own centre. Above this is a second plane, consisting of the handle-frame, the two sides of which are carried by the segments and block just mentioned; the frame has in it two holes C, D which are carried round the centres B, A respectively. Thus C describes a circle about B , and D a circle about A .

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The handle-frame includes also the remaining two sides (11) of the handle-frame, and, let into the same so as to be flush therewith on the upper surface, two slips (12) completing, in this plane, the handle-frame.

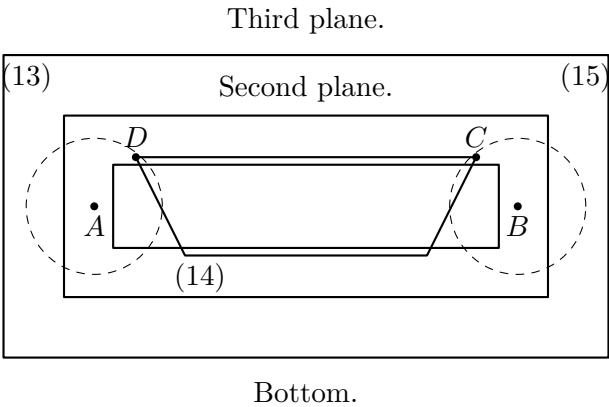
We have thus on a level the sides (11), (12) of the handle-frame and the holes C, D , where C rotates about the point B , which is the centre of the block (3); and D rotates about the point A , which is the centre of the segments (4), each hole being capable of describing a complete circle; and the distances AB, BC, CD , and DA are (within limits) adjustable to any given values: the distance of the holes C, D is made equal to that of the two pegs next referred to.

Connected herewith by means of cylindrical pegs working in the holes C, D respectively, we have a carrying-frame; viz. the fourth plane contains two sides (13) of this carrying-frame, and two moveable bars (14), attached to the remaining two sides (15) of the carrying-frame, and having on their lower surfaces the pegs which work in the holes C and D respectively—each bar being free to rotate about one extremity, and being clampable at the other extremity so as to allow the two pegs to be adjusted at a given distance from each other. And then in the fifth plane we have the remaining two sides (15) of the carrying-frame.

Rigidly connected with the carrying-frame we have the drawing-board; or, to make the whole more complete, this should be adjustable to any given position in regard to the carrying-frame. The drawing-board works under a fixed pencil supported by a bridge; and as the frame is moved by the handle, the point of the board under the pencil traces the required curve.

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ON THE PROBLEM OF THE IN-AND-CIRCUMSCRIBED TRIANGLE.

[From the Philosophical Transactions of the Royal Society of London, vol. CLXI. (for the year 1871), pp. 369–412. Received December 30, 1870,—Read February 9, 1871.]

The problem of the In-and-Circumscribed Triangle is a particular case of that of the In-and-Circumscribed Polygon: the last-mentioned problem may be thus stated—to find a polygon such that the angles are situate in and the sides touch a given curve or curves. And we may in the first instance inquire as to the number of such polygons. In the case where the curves containing the angles and touched by the sides respectively are all of them distinct curves, the number of polygons is obtained very easily and has a simple expression: it is equal to twice the product of the orders of the curves containing the angles and of the classes of the curves touched by the sides.

For the triangle I shall need to consider also the cases in which some of the six curves are identical. I denote the angles by the small letters a, c, e , and the opposite sides by the capitals B, D, F respectively. I use the same letters a, c, e, B, D, F to denote the curves containing the angles and touched by the sides respectively; viz. the angle a is situate in the curve a , the side B touches the curve B , and so for the other angles and sides respectively.

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An equation such as $a = c$ or $a = B$ denotes that the curves a, c or, as the case may be, the curves a, B are one and the same curve: it is in general convenient to use a new letter for denoting these identical curves; viz. I write, for instance, $a = c = x$ or $a = B = x$, to denote that the curves a, c or, as the case may be, the curves a, B are one and the same curve x ; the new letters thus introduced are x, y, z , there being in regard to them no distinction of small letters and capitals. The expression “no identities” denotes that the curves are all distinct. But I use also the letters $a, c, e, b, d, f, x, y, z$, and $A, C, E, B, D, F, X, Y, Z$ quantitatively, to denote the orders and classes of the curves $a, c, e, B, D, F, x, y, z$ respectively; thus, in the Table, for the case 1 “no identities” the number of triangles is given as $= 2aceBDF$, which agrees with the before-mentioned result for the polygon: for the case 2 the several separate identities $a = c$, $a = e$, $c = e$ are of course equivalent to each other; and selecting one of them, $a = c = x$, the number of triangles is given as

$$= 2x(x-1)eBDF.$$

There is a convenience in thus writing down the several forms $a = c$, $a = e$, $c = e$ of the identity or identities which constitute the 52 distinct cases of the Table; and I have accordingly done so throughout the Table, the expression for the number of triangles being however in each case given under one form only.

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TABLE.

No. of Case	Specification	No. of forms	Totals	No. of triangles	Divided by
1	No identities	1	1	$2aceBDF$	
2	$a = c = x; \quad c = e; \quad e = a$	3		$2x(x-1)eBDF$	
3	$D = F = x; \quad F = B; \quad B = D$	3		$2X(X-1)Bace$	
4	$a = D = x; \quad c = F; \quad e = B$	3		$2XaceBF$	
5	$a = B = x$, or $a = F; \quad c = D, \quad c = B; \quad e = F, \quad e = D$	6	15	$2(Xx - X - x)ceDF$	
6	$a = c = e = x$	1		$\{2x(x-1)(x-2) + X\}BDF$	
7	$B = D = F = x$	1		$\{2X(X-1)(X-2) + x\}ace$	
8	$a = c = B = x; \quad c = e = D; \quad e = a = F$	3		$2x(x-3)(X-2)eDF$	

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TABLE (CONTINUED).

No. of Case	Specification	No. of forms	Totals	No. of triangles	Divided by
9	$D = F = e = x; \quad F = B = a; \quad B = D = c$	3		$2X(X-3)(x-2)acB$	
10	$a = c = D = x$, or $a = c = F; \quad c = e = F$, “ $c = e = B; \quad e = a = B$, “ $e = a = D$	6		$2(x-1)(Xx - X - x)eBF$	
11	$D = F = a = x$, or $D = F = c; \quad F = B = c$, “ $F = B = e; \quad B = D = e$, “ $B = D = a$	6	20	$2(X-1)(Xx - X - x)ceB$	
12	$c = e = x, \quad a = D = y; \quad e = a, \quad c = F; \quad a = c, \quad e = B$	3		$2x(x-1)yYBF$	
13	$F = B = x, \quad a = D = y; \quad B = D, \quad c = F; \quad D =$ $F, \quad e = B$	3		$2X(X-1)Yyce$	
14	$c = e = x, \quad a = B = y$, or $c = e, \quad a = F; \quad e = a, \quad c =$ D , “ $e = a, \quad c = B; \quad a = c, \quad e = F$, “ $a = c, \quad e = D$	6		$2x(x-1)(Yy - Y - y)DF$	
15	$F = B = x, \quad D = e = y$, or $F = B, \quad D = c; \quad B =$ $D, \quad F = a$, “ $B = D, \quad F = e; \quad D = F, \quad B = c$, “ $D = F, \quad B = a$	6		(18) (36) $2X(X-1)(Yy - Y - y)ac$	

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TABLE (CONTINUED).

No. of Case	Specification	No. of forms	Totals	No. of triangles	Divided by
16	$c = e = x, D = F = y$, or $c = e, D = B$; $e = a, F = B$, “ $e = a, F = D$; $a = c, B = D$, “ $a = c, B = F$	6		$2x(x-1)Y(Y-1)aB$	2
17	$c = e = x, B = F = y$; $e = a, D = B$; $a = c, F = D$	3		$2x(x-1)Y(Y-1)aD$	
18	$a = D = x, c = B = y$, or $a = D, e = F$; $c = F, e = D$, “ $c = F, a = B$; $e = B, a = F$, “ $e = B, c = D$	6		$2xX(Yy - Y - y)eF$	
19	$c = F = x, e = B = y$; $e = B, a = D$; $a = D, c = F$	3		$2xyXYaD$	
20	$c = D = x, e = F = y$, or $c = B, e = D$; $e = F, a = B$, “ $e = D, a = F$; $a = B, c = D$, “ $a = F, c = B$	6		$2\{xyXY - xy(X+Y) - XY(x+y) + 2xy + 2XY\}aB$	45
21	$c = B = x, e = F = y$; $e = D, a = B$; $a = F, c = D$	3		$2\{xyXY - xy(X+Y) - XY(x+y) + 2xY + 2yX\}aD$	
22	$a = D = x, c = F = y, e = B = z$	1		$2xyzXYZ$	
23	$a = B = x, c = D = y, e = F = z$; $a = F, c = B, e = D$	2		$2\{xyzXYZ - xyz(YZ + ZX + XY) - XYZ(yz + zx + xy) + 2xyz(X+Y+Z) + 2XYZ(x+y+z) - 4xyz - 4XYZ\}$	

ON THE PROBLEM OF THE IN-AND-CIRCUMSCRIBED TRIANGLE.

[Continued from p. 216. Vol. VIII.]

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The following is a continuation of the table of cases for the in-and-circumscribed triangle problem. Each row exhibits the specification of the case, the straight sum, the deficiency, and the number of examples.

Table (continued). Pages 217–221.

<i>No. of Case</i>	<i>Specification</i>	<i>Strt. sum</i>	<i>Def.</i>	<i>No. of examples</i>
30	$a : b : c, a = b = c, \alpha + \beta = \gamma$	(15)	(20)	$2(a - 1)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
31	$a : b : c, a = b, \alpha = \beta = \gamma,$ $\alpha + \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2x(a - 1)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
32	$a : b : c, a = b, \alpha = \beta = \gamma,$ $\alpha + \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2x(a - 1)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
33	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma, \alpha + \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2(a - 1)(aX - aZ)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
34	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma, \alpha + \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2(a - 1)(aX - aZ)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
35	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma, \alpha + \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2(a - 1)(aX - aZ)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
36	$a : b : c, \alpha + \beta = \gamma$	(12) (16)		Quartic case

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<i>No.</i>	<i>Specification</i>	<i>Strt. sum</i>	<i>Def.</i>	<i>No. of examples</i>
37	$a : b : c, a = b = c, \alpha = \beta = \gamma$	(12)	(16)	$2x(a - 1)(X - 2) \cdot YZ$
38	$a : b : c, a = b, \alpha = \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2X(a - 1)(Y - Z) \cdot YZ + Y \cdot V$
39	$a : b : c, a = b, \alpha = \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2(a - 1)(aX - aZ)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
40	$a : b : c, a = b, \beta = \gamma$	6	4	$2(a - 1)(aX - aZ)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
41	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma$	3	6	$2X(a - 1)(X - 2) \cdot YZ$
42	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma$	3	6	$2(a - 1)\{aX - 2(X - 1)Y(X - Z)\} \cdot YZ$

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No.	Specification	Strt. sum	Def.	No. of examples
38	$X = D = P = u, V = v, u = v,$ $P = B = u, B = v, \beta = u - v,$ $D = P = u, D = v$		6	$2X(YpaX + aY)Z \cdot YZ$
39	$X = D = P = u, a = b = c, \beta = v$	6	3	$\{2X^2 + aZY \cdot 8\beta b(b - c) \cdot a(\beta b)^2 - (aP) \cdot a(\beta b)\}$
40	$a : b : c, X = P = u,$ $a : b : c, V = u$		3	$\{a(\beta x)^2 + (aP)^2 \cdot (\beta b)Z \cdot (\beta b) \cdot Z \cdot aX$
41	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma, a = b, \beta b = \nu,$ $D = u, P = v, P = R$		3	$2x(a - 1)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
42	$a : b : c, a = b, \beta = \gamma,$ $D = u, P = v, P = R$		6	$2(a - 1) \cdot Z \cdot Z \cdot abP \cdot ab\alpha\beta(a - 1) \cdot \{aZ + (aP)$
43	$a : b : c, a = b, P = R, \beta = \gamma$		3	$2(a - 1)YZ(Y - Z) \cdot abP$
		(4) (12)		Quartic case

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No.	Specification	Strt. sum	Def.	No. of examples
43	$a : b : c, a = b, \beta = \gamma,$ $P = Q, \alpha = \beta, D = P$	(12)	(17)	$2(a - 1)(aX - aZ)YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta$
44	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma, D = P$	6	8	$2(a - 1) \cdot YZ \cdot Z\alpha\beta - aX\beta \cdot aZ\beta b + 8XZ \cdot aP$
45	$a : b : c, a = b, \beta = \gamma,$ $\alpha + \beta = \gamma, P = Q$	6	5	$2X(a - 1)YZ(Y - Z) \cdot abP \cdot YZ$
46	$a : b : c, a = b, \beta = \gamma,$ $\beta = \gamma$	6	5	$2X(a - 1)YZ(Y - Z) \cdot abP \cdot YZ$
47	$a : b : c, a = b, \beta = \gamma,$ $\alpha = \beta = \gamma$	6	5	$2(a - 1)Y(Y - Z)(Z - aZ)(YZ - Y\beta + aP)\beta$
48	$a : b : c, \beta = \gamma, \alpha = \beta$	6	5	$2(a - 1)Y(Y - Z)(Z - aZ)(YZ - Y\beta + aP)\beta$
		(12) (16)		at infinity

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No.	Specification	Def.	No. of examples
51	$F, a, b, c = a - b = c$		
52	$a = u = b = P \cdot YZ$		$2aY \cdot ab\beta$
			$2X^2(3a^2 - 9aZ - aP + (Z - aZ))$ $+ aX^3(2aZ - aP)(2P - 9P - aZ\beta)$ $+ aX^3(a^2P - aP\beta - aP\beta)$ $+ aX^3(2P - aP\beta)(P - aP)(P - aZ)$ $+ aX^3(2P + aP\beta)(P - aZ)$ $+ (\sum aX^3)(P - aZ\beta)$
D ditto		503	

[Tabular continuation – Several entries in the original scans are partially illegible; symbols and groupings are preserved as faithfully as the source permits.]

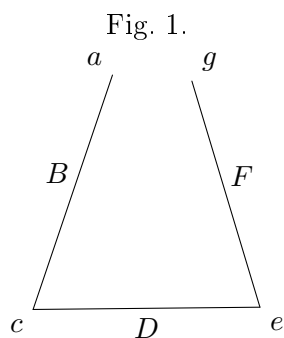
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The foregoing results are chiefly obtained by means of the theory of correspondence; viz. if instead of the triangle $aBcDeF$ we consider the unclosed trilateral $aBcDeFg$, where the points a and g are situate on one and the same curve, say the curve $a = g$, then the points a and g have a certain correspondence, say a (χ, χ') correspondence with each other; and when a, g are a “united point” of the correspondence, the trilateral in question becomes an in-and-circumscribed triangle $aBcDeF$; that is, the number of triangles is equal to that of the united points of the correspondence, subject however (in many of the cases) to a reduction on account of special solutions. It is in particular cases more convenient to consider the correspondence not of the united points in, in several of the cases, but not in all of them, $a = g = \chi = \chi'$. But in some instances I employ a functional method, by assuming that the identical curves are each of them the aggregate of the two curves a, a' : we have obtain for the number $g\sigma$ of the triangles belonging to the curve a a functional equation $\phi(a + a') = \phi a + \phi a'$ given function; viz. the expression on the right-hand side depends on the solution of the preceding cases, wherein the number of identities between the several curves is less than in the case under consideration; and taking it to be known, the functional equation gives $\phi a =$ particular solution + linear function of (a, B, F) . The particular solution is always easily obtainable, and the constant of the linear function can be determined by means of particular forms of the curve a .

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Article Nos. 1 to 6. *The Principles of Correspondence as applied to the present Problem.*

1. Consider the unclosed trilateral $aBcDeFg$, where the points a and g are on one and the same curve, say the curve $a = g$. Starting from an arbitrary point a on the curve, we have αB any one of the tangents from a to the curve B , touching this curve, say at the point B ; and intersecting the curve c in a point c ; viz. c is any one of the intersections of aBc with the curve c ; we have then similarly cDe any one of



the tangents from c to the curve D , touching it, say at D , and intersecting the curve e in a point e ; viz. the point e is any one of the intersections in question; and then in like manner we have eFg any one of the tangents from e to the curve F , touching it, say at F , and intersecting the curve $\alpha(= a)$ in a point g ; viz. g is any one of the intersections in question. Suppose that to a given position of a there correspond χ positions of g , it is easy to find the value of χ ; viz. if (as above tacitly supposed)

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the curves a, B, c, D, e, F are all distinct curves, then the number of these tangents αB is $= B$; there are on each of them c points c ; through each of these we have D tangents cDe ; on each of these e points e ; through each of these F tangents eFg ; and on each of these a points g ; through each of these $\chi = Bcdef\alpha$. But if some of the curves become one and the same curve — if, for instance, $\alpha = B = c$, — the line αBc is here a tangent from a point α on the curve, we exclude the tangent at the point α , and the number of the remaining tangents is $= (A - 2)$; each tangent meets the curve in the point α counting once, the point B counting twice, and in $(\alpha - 3)$ other points; that is, the number of the points c is $= (A - 2)(\alpha - 3)$, and in like cases; the calculation is always immediate, and the only difference is that, instead of a factor α or A , we have such factor in its original form or diminished by 1, 2, or 3, as the case may be. Similarly starting from g , considered as a given point on the curve $g(= a)$, we find χ' the number of the corresponding points a ; thus in the case where the curves are all distinct curves, we have $\chi' = FeDcBa (= \chi)$; and so in other cases we find the value of χ' . The points (a, g) have thus a (χ, χ') correspondence, where the values of χ, χ' are found as above.

2. There will be occasion to consider the case where in the triangle $aBcDeF$ (or say the triangle $aBcDeFa$) the point a is not subjected to any condition whatever, but is a free point. There is in this case a “locus of a ,” which is at once constructed as follows: viz. starting with an arbitrary tangent αB of the curve B , touching it at B and intersecting the curve c in a point c ; through c we draw the curve D the tangent cDe , touching it at D and intersecting the curve e in a point e ; and finally from e to the curve F the tangent eFa , touching it at F and intersecting the original tangent αB in a point α ; the locus of the point α so obtained is an arbitrary tangent of the curve B (or of the curve F).

3. The general form of the equation of correspondence is

$$p(a - x - x') + q(b - \beta - \beta') + \dots = k\Delta(t);$$

viz. if on a curve for which twice the deficiency is $= \Delta$ we have a point P corresponding to certain other points $P', Q', \dots$, in such wise that P, P' have an (x, x') correspondence, P, Q' a (β, β') correspondence, &c.; and if (α) be the number of the united points (P, P') , (β) the number of the united points (P, Q') , &c.; and if moreover for a given position of P the points $P', Q', \dots$ are obtained as the intersections of the curve with a curve Θ (depending on the point P) which meets the curve k times at P ; p times at each of the points P' , q times at each of the

* To avoid confusion with the notation of the present memoir, I abstain in the text from the use of D as denoting the deficiency, and there is a convenience in the use of a single symbol for twice the deficiency; but writing for the moment D to denote the deficiency, I remark, in passing, that perhaps the true theoretical form of the equation is

$$k(2D - D - D) + p(a - x - x') + q(b - \beta - \beta') + \dots = 0,$$

viz. the point P is here considered as having with itself a (D, D) correspondence, the number of the united points therein being $= 0$.

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unilary values $f = \phi - \phi'$ and $v - e - e'$ are obtained by means of a more simple application of the principle of correspondence, as will appear in the sequel (¹), but for the moment I do not pursue the question.

Article Nos. 7 to 14. Locus of a free angle (α).

7. I consider the case where a is a distinct curve $\alpha =, \nu F$, and where, as was seen, the equation is simply

$$g - \chi - \chi' = 0.$$

I suppose further that a is distinct from all the other curves, or say, *simpliciter*, that a is a distinct curve. The values of χ, χ' will here each of them contain the factor a , say we have $\chi = n\alpha$, $\chi' = n'\alpha'$; and therefore the equation gives $g = \alpha(n + \alpha')$. It is obvious that α, α' are the values assumed by χ, χ' respectively in the particular case where the curve α is an arbitrary line ($\alpha = 1$); and $\alpha + \alpha'$ is the number of the united points on this line.

8. Suppose now that in the triangle $aBcDeFa$ the point a is a free point, and have, as above-mentioned, a locus of a , and the united points on the arbitrary line are the intersections of the line with this locus; that is, the locus meets the arbitrary line in $\alpha + \alpha'$ points; or, what is the same thing, the order of the locus is $= \alpha + \alpha'$.

9. I stop for a moment to remark that in the particular case where the curve B is a point ($B = 1$), then in the construction of the locus of α the arbitrary tangent αB is an arbitrary line through B , and the construction gives on this line a position of the point α . But drawing from B a tangent to the curve F , and thus constructing in order the points F, e, D, c, α , the construction shows that B is an α' -tuple point on the locus; and (by what precedes) an arbitrary line through B meets the locus in α other points; that is, in the particular case where the curve B is a point, the order of the locus of α is $= \alpha + \alpha'$, which agrees with the foregoing result.

10. The construction for the locus of α may be presented in the following form: viz. drawing to the curve D a tangent cDe , meeting the curves c, e in the points c, e respectively; then if from any point c we draw to the curve B a tangent cBa , and from any point e to the curve F a tangent eFa , the tangents cBa, eFa intersect in a point on the required locus. Hence if in any particular case (that is for any particular position of the tangent cDe) the lines cBa, eFa become one and the same line, the point a will be an indeterminate point on this line; that is, the line in question will be part of the locus of a .

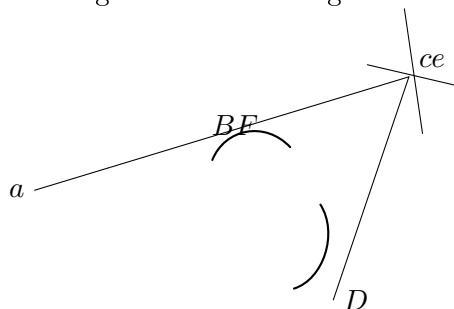
11. The case cannot in general arise so long as the curves B, F are distinct from each other; but when these are one and the same curve $B = F$, then the line cBa will be a tangent of the curve B , and we have thus as part of the locus the locus $c = e$ if it can be drawn, the same being supposed to. To show how this is, suppose in, say at F , and intersecting the curve cBe , it is needful, that perhaps the true theoretical form of the equation is¹

¹ See post, Nos. 24 *et seq.*

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here a tangent at B passing through a point α of the intersection of this curve α , and from this point a tangent drawn to the curve $B = F$. For the position in question of the tangent of D , the points c, e coincide with each other, and we have thus the coincident tangents cBa and eFa as the identical curves $B = F$. It is further

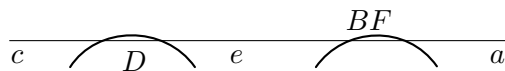
Fig. 2. First-mode figure.



to be remarked that the number of the points of intersection is $= \sigma$; from each of these there are B tangents to the curve F (in all σB tangents), and each of these counts once in respect of each of the D tangents to the curve D ; that is, it counts D times. We have thus as part of the locus of α on B lines each D times, or, say, first-mode reduction $= \sigma BD$.

12. The second mode is there in the same manner “second-mode figure.” The tangent from D is here a common tangent of the curves D and $B = F$. This meets the curve c in σ points; and the curve e in σ points; and attending to one pair of points c, e on each of these the tangents cBa, eFa , coinciding with the common tangent

Fig. 3. Second-mode figure.



in question, and forming part of the locus of α . The number of the common tangents is $= BD$; but each of these counts once in respect of each combination of the points c, e ; that is in all σ times. And we have thus as part of the locus BD lines each σ times, or, say, second-mode reduction $= BD \cdot \sigma$. This is (as it happens) the same number as for the first mode; but to distinguish the different origins I have written as above $\sigma \cdot BD$ and $BD \cdot \sigma$ respectively.

13. It is important to remark that each of the two modes arises whatever relations of identity subsist between the curves σ, c, B , and F , but with consideration of these. Thus if any one of the lines cBa, eFa is not so situate (but is so far) distinct from B , then in the first-mode figure as may be a node or a cusp of the curve $\sigma = \sigma$, it, say at F , and intersecting the curve $\sigma = \sigma$, it is needful to find a copy of the entire of the intersections in question. Suppose that for a given position of D touching the curve $c = e$ in the neighbourhood of the node, thus of the two points of intersection each $c = e$ is in the neighbourhood of the node, thus of the two points of intersection each

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in succession may be taken for the point c , and the other of them will be the point e ; so that the node counts twice. It requires more consideration to perceive, but it will be readily accepted that the cusp counts three times. Hence if for the curve $c = e$ the number of nodes be $= \delta$ and that of cusps $= \kappa$, the value of the first-mode reduction is $= (2\delta + 3\kappa)BD$.

As regards the second-mode figure, the only difference is that c, e will be now any pair of intersections (each pair twice) of the tangent with the curve $c = e$; and the value is thus $= (c^2 - c)BD$.

It would be by no means uninteresting to enumerate the different cases, and indeed there might arise some advantage in doing so here; but I have (instead of this) considered the several cases, when and as they arise in connexion with any of the cases of the in-and-circumscribed triangle.

14. Observe that the general result is, that in the case $B = F$ of the identity of the curves B and F , but not otherwise, the locus of α includes as part of itself a system of lines; or, say, that it is made up of the proper locus, the lines, and of a residual curve of the order $\alpha + \alpha' - \text{Red.}$, which is the proper locus.

Article Nos. 15 to 17. *Application of the foregoing Theory as to the locus of (α) .*

15. Reverting now to the case where the angle a is not a free angle but is situate on a given curve α , then if the curve α is distinct from the curves α, F , the number of positions of α is, as was seen, $g = \chi + \chi'$. But the points in question are the intersections of the line-system $\alpha F \gamma$ with the curve α ; and the line-system $\alpha F \gamma$ being made up of the proper locus — Red. and of a system of lines is on this account distinct from the curve α ; the points of intersection on the proper locus must convenient to obtain directly one than the other of two reciprocal results; for instance, to consider the case $B = D = F$ rather than $\alpha = e = e$, since in the equation in the $\chi = \chi'$ Red., the entry in the expression $\alpha + \alpha' - \text{Red.}$, the order of the proper locus of α .

16. It is however to be noticed that if the curve α , being as is assumed distinct from the curves α , and $F = B$, is identical with one or both of the remaining curves c, D , the foregoing expression $\chi + \chi'$ for the order of αBe , gives points a which are not true solutions of the problem, viz. the curve α may include in general in easier and more convenient to obtain directly one than the other of two reciprocal results; for instance, of lines, or reduction in the expression $\alpha + \alpha' - \text{Red.}$ of the order of the proper locus of α .

¹ More generally, if the curve α is a curve identical with any of the other curves, then if treating in the first instance the angle α as the free we find in any manner the locus of α , the required positions of the angle α are the intersections of this locus and of the curve α ; but these intersections will in general include intersections which give heterotypic solutions. The determination of these is a matter of some delicacy, and I have in general treated the problem in each manner that the question does not arise; but an example see post, Case 45.

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17. But this cannot happen if the curve a is distinct also from the curves c, D ; or, say, simply when a is a distinct curve. The conclusion is, that in the case where a is a distinct curve we have

$$g = \chi + \chi' - \text{Red.},$$

where the term “Red.” vanishes except in the case of the identity $B = F$ of the curves B, F ; and that when this identity subsists it is $= \sigma$ times the reduction in the order of the locus of a considered as a free angle; viz. this consists of a first- mode and a second-mode reduction as above explained.

Article Nos. 18 to 21. *Remarks in regard to the Solutions for the 52 Cases.*

18. Before going further I remark that the principle of correspondence applies to corresponding and united tangents in like manner as to corresponding and united points, and that all the investigations in regard to the in-and-circumscribed triangle might thus be presented in the reciprocal form, where, instead of points and lines, we have lines and points respectively. But there is no occasion to employ any such reciprocal process; the result to which it would lead is the reciprocal of a result given by the original process, and as such it can always be obtained by reciprocation of the original result, without any performance of the reciprocal process.

19. It is hardly necessary to remark that although reciprocal results would, by the employment of the two processes respectively, be obtained in a precisely similar manner, yet that this is not so when only one of the reciprocal processes is made use of; so that, using one process only, it may be in general in easier and more convenient to obtain directly one than the other of two reciprocal results; for instance, to consider the case $B = D = F$ rather than $a = c = e$. Forcing the analogy in such a case, to consider the case $B = D = F$ rather than $a = c = e$, and having obtained the one result, directly to deduce from it the other by reciprocity; but that it may nevertheless be interesting to obtain each of the two results directly.

20. It is moreover obvious that although the several forms of the same case, for instance Case 2, $a = c$, $a = e$, or $c = e$, are absolutely equivalent to each other, yet that, when as above we select a vertex a , and seek for the number of the united points (a, g) , the process of obtaining the result will be altogether different according to the different form which we employ. For instance, in the case just referred to, if the form is taken to be $a = c$ or $c = e$, then the equation $g = \chi + \chi'$ is applicable to it; but not so if the form is taken to be $a = e$. It would by no means uninteresting in every case to consider the several forms successively; but it appears that in every case it cannot however be carried out very far, considering, illustration, verification, or otherwise it appears proper so to do. The translation of a result, for instance, of a form $a = c$ or $c = e$ into that for the form $a = c = e$ is so easy and obvious, that it is not even necessary formally to make it.

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21. I do not at present further consider the general theory, but proceed to consider in order the 52 cases, interpreting in regard to the general theory each further discussion or explanation as may appear necessary. In the several instances in which the equation $g = \chi + \chi'$ is applicable, it is sufficient to write down the values of χ, χ' , the mode of obtaining these being already explained.

The 52 Cases for the in-and-circumscribed triangle.

Case 1. No identities.

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= BcDeFa, & \chi' &= FeDcBa (= \chi), \\ g &= 2aBcDF.\end{aligned}$$

Case 2. $a = c = e$.

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= B(a-1)DeFa, & \chi' &= FeD(a-1)Ba, \\ g &= 2a(a-1)BDF.\end{aligned}$$

Second process, for form $a = c = e$. The equation of correspondence is here

$$g - \chi - \chi' + F(a - c - c') = 0;$$

but the points e being given as all the intersections of the curve $a(=c)$ by the line-system cDe which does not pass through a , we have $c = c' = 0$, so that $g = \chi + \chi'$; and then

$$\begin{aligned}g &= BcDeFa(= 2a - 1) + FeDcBa, \\ &= 2a(a - 1)BDF,\end{aligned}$$

giving the former result⁽¹⁾.

Case 3. $B = F = e$. Reciprocation from 2; or else, second process,

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= DeBa(B-1)a, & \chi' &= De(B-1)Ba, \\ g &= 2X(X-1)Daa.\end{aligned}$$

Third process: form $F = Ba = e$. We have here $g = \chi + \chi' - \text{Red.}$,

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= BcDaBa, & \chi' &= BcD(\alpha)a, \\ \chi + \chi' &= 2X^2Dca.\end{aligned}$$

and the reductions are those of the first and second mode, as explained ante, Nos. 13, 14, viz. each of them is $= X \cdot Dca$, and together they are $= 2XDca$; whence the foregoing result.

Case 4. $a = B = a$.

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= BcDeFa, & \chi' &= FeDc(\alpha - 2)a, \\ g &= 2XaeDF.\end{aligned}$$

¹ Of course, the result is obtained in the form belonging to the next form of specification, viz. here it is $= 2(a-1)BDF$, and as in other instances; but it is unnecessary to refer to this change.

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Observe this is what the result for Case 1 becomes on writing therein $a = B = a$, viz. the opposite curves a, D may become one and the same curve without any alteration in the form of the result.

Case 5. $a = B = a$.

$$\chi = (X - 2)cDeFa, \quad \chi' = FeDcXa(X - 1),$$

where

$$(X - 2) + x \cdot X(x - 1) = X(x - 1) = X(X - x - 1);$$

therefore

$$g = X(Xa - X - a)cDF.$$

Case 6. $a = c = e = a = a$: perhaps most easily by reciprocation of Case 5. The triangle $aBcDeF$ is here in succession each of the eight triangles

$$\begin{array}{cccc} a B\alpha D\alpha F & a B\alpha' D\alpha F & a B\alpha' D\alpha F & a B\alpha D\alpha' F \\ a' B\alpha D\alpha' F, & a B\alpha' D\alpha F, & a B\alpha' D\alpha F, & a B\alpha D\alpha' F, \\ a B\alpha D\alpha F, & a' B\alpha D\alpha' F, & a' B\alpha D\alpha F, & a' B\alpha D\alpha F, \\ a' B\alpha D\alpha' F, & a' B\alpha' D\alpha F, & a' B\alpha' D\alpha F, & a B\alpha' D\alpha F, \end{array}$$

where the two top triangles give Δa and $\Delta a'$ respectively; the remaining triangles all belong to Case 2, and those of the first column give each $2(a^2 - x)BDF$, and those of the second column each $2(a^2 - x)'BDF$. We have then

$$\phi(a + a') = \Delta a + \Delta a' + \{4(a^2 + aa') - 12aa'\}BDF,$$

which is twice the function in question, on the right-hand side we may write

$$\phi a = 2a^2 - 2x'\alpha = \Delta x + a(BX + a)BDF,$$

that is to say so that, a, B are independent of the curves B, D, F ; and taking each of these to be a point, and the curve $a = c = e$ to be a conic, this is known that $\phi = 2$; we have therefore $\Delta = 12 + 8a$ in this case, that is $a + B = 2$.

The case where the curve $a = c = e$ is a line gives $\phi = 2 : 4 + a = 2$, that is $a = 2$, let it is not easy to find another condition; assuming however $\eta = 0$, we have $a = 2$, $B = -1$, and hence therefore

$$\Delta a = 2a(a - 1)(2a - 1) + a(B - 1)BD,$$

or my

$$g = 2(a - 1)(a - 2) + aD,$$

this is a good easy example of the functional process, the use of which appears to exhibit itself; and I have therefore given it, notwithstanding the difficulty as to the complete determination of the constants.

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Third process. The equation of correspondence is

$$g - \chi - \chi' + F(a - c - c') = 0,$$

but for the correspondence (a, c) we have

$$c - c' = v + D(a - y - y') = 0,$$

and for the correspondence (a, c) ,

$$c - c' = g' - aDa,$$

whence

$$g = \chi + \chi' + aDF \cdot \Delta;$$

that is

$$g = B(a - 1)D(a - 1)Fa + F(a - 1)D(a - 1)Ba + 2(a - 1)(a - 1)y;$$

Moreover

$$\chi + \chi' = B(a - 1)D(a - 1)Fa \cdot Z,$$

$$\Delta = X - 2a + 8 + a,$$

(if a be the number of cusps of the curve $a = c = e$), and the resulting value is

$$g = 2\{(a - 1)BDF \cdot a - 2\}.$$

[Author's remark on the value of $aBDF$:]

[F as the number of cusps of the curve $a = c = e$, the resulting value of g is

$$g = 2(a - 1)BDF \cdot \alpha.$$

Where, however, the term $aBDF$ is to be rejected, I cannot quite explain this; I should rather have expected a rejection $= 2aBDF$, introducing the term $-aBDF$. For consider a tangent from the curve D from a cusp of the curve $a = c = e$; there are D such tangents; each gives in the neighbourhood of the cusp two points, say c, e ; and from these we draw B tangents cBa to the curve B , and F tangents eFa to the curve F ; we have then in respect of the given tangent of D , BF positions of the α tangent of D , BF positions of a , in all $aBDF$ positions of which b corresponds together with the cusp; and for all the cusps together $aBDF$ such triangles; this would be what is wanted; the difficulty is that as if the two intersections at the cusp each in succession may be taken for c , and the other of them for α , it would seem that the foregoing number $aBDF$ should be multiplied by 2.]

Case 7. $B = D = F = a$. Here $g = \chi + \chi'$ — Red.

$$\chi = Xc(X - 1)e(X - 2)a, \quad \chi' = Xc(X - 1)e(X - 2)a,$$

that is

$$\chi + \chi' = 2Xa \cdot ce.$$

The reductions of the two modes are as above, with only the variation that in the present case B is the same curve with the two curves $B = F$. That of the first mode is $= X(X - 1) \cdot ce$, and that of the second mode is $= (2e - 1) \cdot Xce$, or substituting, we have together they are $= 2X(X - 1) \cdot ce$; or substituting, we have

$$g = 2X(X - 1)X(X - 2) + ce.$$

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Case 8. $a = c = B = a$.

$$\chi = (X - 2)(a - 1)DeFa, \quad \chi' = FeDa(X - 1)(a - 1)a,$$

$$g = Xc(a - 1)(X - 1)DeF.$$

Case 9. $D = F = a = a$. By reciprocation of 8.

$$\chi = X(X - 1)(X - 2)cDF.$$

Case 10. $a = c = B = a$.

$$\chi = B(a - 1)(X - 2)DeFa, \quad \chi' = FeX(a - 2)Ba(a - 1),$$

$$g = X(x - 1)X(a - 1)DeF.$$

Case 11. $D = F = a = a$. By reciprocation of 10.

$$\chi = X(X - 1)(X - 2) \cdot caa.$$

Second process: form $a = B = a = a$.

$$\chi = (X - 1)(a - 1)caXa, \quad \chi' = FeXa(X - 1)(a - 1) \cdot a;$$

giving the former result.

Case 12. $a = c = e = a$, $B = F$.

$$\chi = BcD(a - 1)Fa, \quad \chi' = FaT(a - 1)Ba (= \chi),$$

$$g = 2(a - 1) \cdot BDF.$$

Case 13. $F = B = a$, $a = c = e = a$. By reciprocation of 12.

$$\chi = 2X(X - 1) \cdot DF.$$

Case 14. $a = c = e$, $B = F = a$.

$$\chi = X(X - 1)(a - 1)caFa, \quad \chi' = FaT(a - 1)F(a - 2) (= \chi),$$

$$g = 2X(X - 1)Y(F - 1) + \cdot ce.$$

Case 15. $F = B = a$, $D = F = a$. By reciprocation of 14.

$$\chi = X(X - 1)(X - 2)Y \cdot DF.$$

Case 16. $a = c = e$, $B = F = a$.

$$\chi = B(a - 1)(X - 1)caa, \quad \chi' = F(a - 1)(X - 2)Ba (= \chi),$$

$$g = Xa(a - 1)Y(X - 1).$$

Case 17. $a = c = e$, $B = F = a$.

$$\chi = B(a - 1)(X - 1)(B - 1)ca, \quad \chi' = Fa(a - 1) \cdot caR(a - 1) (= \chi),$$

$$g = 2X(a - 1)Y(X - 1)a.$$

But we have here aD as an axis of symmetry, so that triangle is counted twice, or the number of distinct triangles is $= \frac{1}{2}g$.

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Case 18. $a = D = c, c = B = g.$

$$\chi = Y(g - X)caFa, \quad \chi' = FaY(Y - X)caaa,$$

$$g = 2aXY(Y - y)cF.$$

Case 19. $c = B = a, D = F = e.$

$$\chi = Y(g - 1)D(Y - X)c = ea, \quad \chi' = Xy(Y - X)c = Da,$$

$$g = 2aYYY.$$

Case 20. $c = B = a, D = F = e.$

$$\chi = Bc(Y - X)cYY = ea, \quad \chi' = Y(Y - X)YDYca,$$

$$g = 2(Y - X)\{aXY + aY + aZ\} - X(Y - X)Yca + 2aZF.$$

Case 21. $c = B = a, D = F = e.$

$$\chi = Yc(Y - X)caXa, \quad \chi' = XyY(Y - X)caYa,$$

$$g = 2YcaYY.$$

Case 22. $a = D = c = a = e, F.$

$$\chi = c(X - 1)Da = Fa, \quad \chi' = Fc(X - 1)cDya,$$

$$g = 2Y(X - 1)c \cdot c = F.$$

Case 23. $a = D = c = a = e, F.$

$$\chi = (Y - 2)c(Y - 1)D(Y - 1)y \cdot Fa, \quad \chi' = Fa(Y - 2)cD(Y - 1)Y \cdot ca,$$

$$g = 2(Y - X)c(Y - X - 1)(Y - 2)\{(Y - X)cF\} + 2(Y - 1)yF + aXY + aYZ\} \cdot ZF \cdot \tan;$$

this is then the symmetry of the result of two modes; or any other case.

Case 24. $a = D = c, D = c = e = Fa.$

$$\chi = Yy(X - 1)Da = Fa, \quad \chi' = Yy = X(X - 1) \cdot ea (= \chi),$$

$$g = 2c(X - 1)Y(Y - 1)y \cdot ca.$$

Case 25. $c = e = a = a = D = F = v.$ Here

$$g = \chi + \chi' - \text{Red.},$$

$$\chi = Xy(X - 1)(Y - 1)ca, \quad \chi' = XyY(X - 1)\{(Y - 1)(Y - 1)\}(= \chi) e \cdot a;$$

$$\chi + \chi' = v(y - 1) \cdot 2XY(X - 1) \cdot ca.$$

The reductions are those of the first and second modes; $c = e$, and that the curve D is identical with the curves $B = F$.

First-mode reduction is

$$v(C + 2g + 5\kappa)B(B - 1)$$

(where δ, κ refer to the curves $c = e$), which is

$$= v(c - 1)BB(B - 1);$$

that is, the reduction is $= v(g-1)Y(X-1)$.

Second-mode reduction is

$$v(2c+5c)c(X-1)$$

that is, the reduction is $= v(c-1)y(X-1) \cdot c \cdot (Y-1)$;

Hence the two together are $= v(c-1)\{2Y(X-1) + y(Y-1)y\}$; and subtracting from $\chi + \chi'$ we have

$$g = v(g-1) \cdot \{2X(X-1) - c\}c.$$

but on account of the symmetry each triangle is reckoned twice, and the number of triangles is $= \frac{1}{2}g$.

Case 26. $a = c = B = a, D = e = F = v$. By reciprocation of 25.

$$\chi = Y(c-1)(Y-1)2 - y(Y-X)Y \cdot cy.$$

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Case 26. $a = c = e = a$, $B = D = v$, $u = F = v$.

$$\chi = Y(a-1)(Y-1)e \cdot 2 - y \cdot Fa, \quad \chi' = Z(Y-1)Y(Y-2)Y(Y-1)(a-1)(a-2);$$

$$\begin{aligned} g &= v(a-1)Y(Y-1) \cdot e \cdot F(Y-1) \\ &= 2c(a-1)Y(X-1)(a-2) + F(2-A); \end{aligned}$$

Case 27. $c = e = a$, $B = F = a$, $a = D = v$. By reciprocation of 26.

$$\chi = Y(a-1)Y(Y-1) - y(Y-X)Y \cdot xY = 2v(a-1)(Y-X)yF.$$

where each triangle counted is twice, so that the number is really one half of this.

Case 28. $a = c = B = a$, $D = e = F = v$.

$$\chi = Yc(Y-1)(Y-2)e \cdot Z, \quad \chi' = Y(Y-1)y \cdot Yc(Y-2)e = v;$$

The reductions are those of the first and second modes; as explained above, with the variation that the curves c and a are here identical, $a = c$, and that the curve D is identical with the curves $B = F$.

First-mode reduction is

$$v(C + 2\delta + 3\kappa)B(B-1)$$

(where δ, κ refer to the curve $c = a$), which is

$$= v(c-1) \cdot Y(Y-1);$$

that is, the reduction is $= v(g-1) \cdot Y(Y-1)$.

Second-mode reduction is

$$v(c-2c)c(X-1)$$

that is, the reduction is $= v(g-1) \cdot Y(Y-1)$.

Hence the two together are $= v(g-1)\{2X(X-1) - c\} \cdot e$, and subtracting from $\chi + \chi'$ the value of g is

$$g = v(g-1) \cdot \{2Y(Y-1) - e\} \cdot e.$$

but on account of the symmetry we must divide by $\frac{1}{2}g$.

Case 29. $c = a = D = v$, $a = c = v$. By reciprocation of 28.

$$\chi = 2X(X-1) \cdot v(v-1) \cdot a.$$

Case 30. $a = c = B = a$, $D = e = v$, $u = F = v$. By reciprocation of 24.

$$\chi = Z(a-1)(Y-1)(Y-2) \cdot eYF \cdot eYF = v \cdot a(Y-1)Y(Y-2)YF.$$

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Second process. Taking the form

$$c = B = u = a, \quad D = F = u;$$

here

$$g = \chi + \chi' - \text{Red.},$$

$$\chi = Yc(X-1)Da \cdot Ya, \quad \chi' = Yc(X-1) \cdot c \cdot Ye,$$

and

$$\chi + \chi' = 2Y^2v(a-1)D \cdot e(X-1).$$

There is a first-mode reduction,

$$\begin{aligned} & aY\{2v + 3v \cdot (B-1) \cdot v + aZ(X-Y) \\ & + (X-3)v(v-c-1)Y \cdot a \cdot \beta\} \\ & + (X-3)v(X-2Y) \\ & + (X-3)(YYY); \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$= aY\{X(2v-c-1)\} + v \cdot a \cdot \alpha;$$

and a second-mode reduction is

$$= aYX(X(Y(c-1)Y(c-1) + 12c) \cdot c$$

Hence the two together are

$$= aY\{X(2v-c-1)\} + v(c-1) \cdot (Y-c(Y-c-1)),$$

whence the result is

$$= 2(P-Y)(c(c-1)Y(Y-c),$$

which agrees with that obtained above.

On account of the symmetry we must divide by $\frac{1}{2}g$.

Case 31. $a = D = F = a, u = v = v$. By reciprocation of 30.

$$\chi = 2X(X-1)(X-2) \cdot v(v-1)y.$$

On account of the symmetry we must divide by $\frac{1}{2}g$.

Case 32. $a = c = v, D = e = u$. By reciprocation of 24.

$$\chi = 2X(X-1)(X-2)v(v-1)c.$$

Case 33. $u = c = v, a = D = u$.

$$\chi = Y(Y-1)c(Y-2)ay, \quad \chi' = F(Y-1)e \cdot D(Y-c)ya \cdot ZY + YF.$$

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Case 33. $u = c = v, a = D = u$.

$$\chi = Y(Y-1)c(Y-1)(a-1)aFa, \quad \chi' = F(Y-1)e \cdot D(Y-2)a \cdot (X-2);$$

$$g = 2X(X-1)(X-2)YcDF.$$

Case 34. $u = e = v, F = u.$

$$\chi = (X - 2)c(X - 1)De \cdot ya, \quad \chi' = YeYFeDc \cdot Xa(X - 1);$$

$$g = Y(c - 1)Y(X - 1)(Y - 2)Da.$$

Case 35. $u = a = v, B = F = u.$ By reciprocation of 34.

$$\chi = 2Y(Y - 1)(Y - 2)F(Y - 2) \cdot cBe.$$

Case 36. $a = c = v, B = F = u.$

$$\chi = B(X - 1)(X - 2)(X - 1)aFa, \quad \chi' = F(X - 1)YX(X - 1)(X - 2)a;$$

$$g = Y(c - 1)(X - 2)YF.$$

Case 37. $a = c = v, D = v, F = v.$ By reciprocation of 36.

$$\chi = Y(X - 1)(X - 2)Y(X - 1)(X - 2)YDBe + 2YXF.$$

Case 38. $B = D = v, a = v, F = v.$

$$\chi = Y(X - 1)YFa, \quad \chi' = Y(X - 1)eF(X - 1)a;$$

$$g = 2Y(X - 1)YF.$$

*Functional process; the curve c is assumed to be the aggregate of two curves, say $a = c + c'.$
Drawing the construction...*

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which is belongs; thus $aXcDcF$ is $B = c = v = v$, which is Case 10, and so in the other instances. Observing that cases 10 and 14 occur each twice, we have

$$\phi(c + c') - \phi c - \phi c' = DF \text{ multiplied by}$$

$$\begin{aligned} & k(c-1)(X-X+v)\alpha \dots\dots (19) \times 2 \\ & + 2c(c-1)(v-X-1) \dots\dots (8) \\ & + 4c(c-1)(X-X-1) \dots\dots (14) \times 2 \\ & + 2c(c-1)F \dots\dots (12) \\ & + 2c(c-2)F \dots\dots (11) \end{aligned}$$

where the ζ, β refer to the like functions with the two sets of letters interchanged. Developing and reducing, this is

$$\begin{aligned} & \phi(c + c') - \phi c - \phi c' = DF \text{ multiplied by} \\ & \quad 3XX \\ & + X(2avX + 5cv' + 8aX' - 15aa - 15a'a + 8) \\ & + 5v(vX - 3v' + a - 1)Y \cdot cz' - 3a' - 3a'X - 3a'X + 3aX' + 6aX' \\ & - 13(cc' + aa') + 9aav, \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} & \phi = DF \text{ multiplied by} \\ & \quad X^4 \\ & + X(2cv - 10v' + 13c) - LX \\ & - 4cv + 25v' - M, \end{aligned}$$

where the constants L, l, λ have to be determined. Does η being a cubic curve the number of triangles vanishes; that is, we have $\phi = 0$ for $a = 1, X = 0, \beta = 0$, and for $a = Z = 0, \beta = 0$ and $a = Z, \beta = 0$; we thus have

$$\begin{cases} a = 8, & X = 0, \beta = 10, \\ 0 = 88 - 4L - M - 15a, \\ 0 = 88 - 4L - M - 15a, \end{cases}$$

giving $L = 1, l = 16, \lambda = 3$. Whence finally,

$$\phi = (X^4 + X(2cv - 10v' + 13c - 1) \cdot c - Y + 2XZ - 16c - 3a^3]DF.$$

Second process; by reciprocation, we have

$$\begin{aligned} g - \chi - \chi' + F(c - c' - c') &= 0, \\ c - c' &= F(v - y - y') = 0. \end{aligned}$$

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and thence

$$g - \chi - \chi' = DF(c + v - y' - y'),$$

Moreover

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= (X - 2)e(X - 1)F(c - 1), \\ \chi &= F(c - 1)e(X - 1)(X - 1)a, \quad \chi = va, \\ \chi + \chi' &= DF \cdot (X - 1)a(X - 1)a,\end{aligned}$$

and

$$v - y - y' = (X - X)a + 2(X - X)a - 3,$$

as is easily obtained, but see also post, No. 21; hence

$g = DF$ multiplied by

$$\begin{aligned}&\{(X - 1) + (X - 1)(X - 1)\}^2 \\ &+ (X - 1)(X - 1)a^2;\end{aligned}$$

but I reject the term $DF(X - 1)a$ as not first giving a heterotypic solution; I do not go into the explanation of this. And then substituting for β its value, we have

$g = DF$ multiplied by

$$\begin{aligned}&(X - 1) \cdot \{a(v - 1)(c - 1)\} \\ &+ X^4 - Xa + 5a - 3a^2,\end{aligned}$$

where the second factor is

$$= X^4 + X(2cv - 10v' + 13c - 1) \cdot c - 4cv + 2c - 16c - 3a^3.$$

which is the foregoing result.

Case 40. $B = D = F = a = v$. By reciprocation of 39.

$$\chi = v \cdot a + v(X^4 + y(2Y - 10Y + 13Y - 1) \cdot Y - 4Y + 25Y - 16Y - 3a^3]F.$$

Case 41. $c = e = a$, $D = F = a$.

$$\chi = Bc(X - 1)e \cdot D(X - 1)Fa, \quad \chi' = Fc(X - 1)(c - 1)Ba,$$

$$g = (X - 1)cD(X - 1)Ba + 2(X - 1)(B - 1)(X - 1) \cdot ca(B - c - 1)cBa,$$

= &c.

Case 42. $a = c = e = v$, $B = D = F = a = v$.

Functional Process; the curve a is supposed to be the aggregate of two curves, say $a = c + c'$, $B = D = F = v = v'$. Forming the construction...

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The enumeration is

<i>Case</i>		
<i>a Bc X d X</i>	<i>aBc X d X</i> ³ ,	(42)
<i>a'.a'Xa X</i>	ditto,	(11)
<i>a.a'Xa X</i>		(11)
<i>a.a'Xa X</i>		(12)
<i>a'XcXa X</i>		(17)
<i>a'XcXa X</i>		(10)
<i>a'XcXa X</i>		(10)
<i>a'XcXa X</i>		(10)

whence

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi(c + c') - \phi c - \phi c' = \nu B \text{ multiplied by} \\
 & 4(X - 1)(Xa - X - a) \dots (11) \times 2 \\
 & + 2\nu(a - 1)X^2 \dots (12) \times 1 \\
 & + 4\nu(a - 1)X(X - 1) \dots (17) \times 2 \\
 & + 5\nu(a - 1)X^2 \dots (10) \times 2 \\
 & + 5\nu Xa(a - 1)X + X(c - 1) + 4\nu(Xa' + X'a) + 2\nu(X'a)X + \dots (10)
 \end{aligned}$$

where the ζ, β' refer to the like functions with the two sets of letters interchanged. Developing and reducing, we have

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi(c + c') - \phi c - \phi c' = aB \text{ multiplied by} \\
 & X^4 (8aa' - 5a^2a^2 - 6aa) \\
 & + XX'\{4aX(c - 1) + 8a^2X + aa(a - 2c + 9) + (c - 1)X\} \\
 & + X^3\{2v' - 6a^2 + 15a^2\} \\
 & + X^3\{12aa - 6aa' - 12a^2 + 18a\} \\
 & + X^2\{(-6a^2 - 12a + 15a^2) \\
 & + Saa^2,
 \end{aligned}$$

and consequently

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi = v \text{ multiplied by} \\
 & XY(4ac - 5a^2) \\
 & + X^4\{l\sigma a^2 + \nu c - 6a^2\} \\
 & + X^3\{(\beta - 5\nu) + \beta - Ja\},
 \end{aligned}$$

where the constants L, l, λ have to be determined. The number of triangles vanishes when the curve α is a line or a conic, that is, $\phi = 0$ for $a = 1, X = 0, \beta = 0$, and for $a = 2, \beta = 2$; we thus have

$$\begin{aligned}
 0 &= 83 - L - M, \\
 0 &= 80 + 2L + 12 - M,
 \end{aligned}$$

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Moreover, the data being equicipanyl, the result must be so likewise; we must therefore have $L = l$. We thus obtain $L = l = u$, $M = 0$, $\lambda =$ but $aBL = u\bar{l}$, $u = Bp = u^2$.

Second process. by correspondence: form $a = c = e =$, $D = F = a$. We have also from the special consideration that the points B, F are given as the intersections of the curve a , by the joint of the joint c , which first pulse does not pass through a , we have

$$(I - \phi - \phi') + \nu(c - X - Y) = v\nu,$$

and by the consideration that c, D are given as intersections, c a double intersection, of the curve with the first point of the point c , which first pulse does not pass through a ,

$$\nu - X - X + 2(v - c - y - y') = v\nu,$$

where

$$g - \chi - \chi' = \nu v - \nu B\nu,$$

and

$$v - c - y' - y' = \nu B\nu,$$

so that this is

$$\begin{aligned} g - \chi - \chi' &= 4\nu B\nu, \\ &= 4\nu(aB - X(X - 1)) \cdot v. \end{aligned}$$

Also

$$\begin{aligned} \chi &= B(X - 1)(X - 1)(X - 2)e \cdot Fa, \\ \chi' &= FeD(X - 1)X(X - 1) \cdot ae \cdot \chi, \end{aligned}$$

so that

$$\begin{aligned} g &= B\nu \text{ multiplied by} \\ 2(X - 1) \cdot (X - 1) \cdot (X - 2) + 4\nu + 5z + RB; \end{aligned}$$

viz. this is

$$B\nu(X^4 - X(X - X - X)(X - 1)(X - 1) + 8c) \cdot Xa + xa + e),$$

which is the number of positions of the angle (a) , but several of these belong to special times of the triangle $aBcDeF$, giving heterotypic solutions, which are to be rejected; the required number is

$$[XY(X - 1)(X - 1)(X - 1)(X - 2)\nu^3 - a\nu^3] - \text{Red.}$$

Third process: form $c = a = B$, $a = Ye$.

$$g = g + \chi' - \text{Red.},$$

$$\chi = X - (X - 1)(X - 1)e \cdot v\nu,$$

$$\chi = X - (X - 1)BY(X - 1) - YcY,$$

$$\chi + \chi' = 2X^4(X - 1)(X - 1)Y(X - 1) - YcY.$$

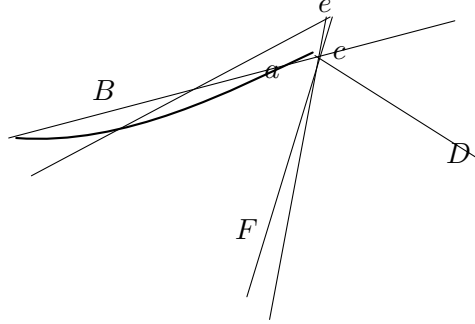
The first-mode reduction is here

$$aB[X - (X - 1)X - (X - 1)4].$$

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where the last term aBe arises from the tangents cBa and eFa , each coinciding with a cuspidal tangent, as shown in the figure.

Fig. 4.



The second-mode reduction is

$$aBX(X-1)(c-3a),$$

so that the two reductions together are

$$= aB\{(X-1)X + (X-1)(B - (X-1)k + e + e(c-2)(c-3a)),$$

viz. this is

$$= aB\{X(X-1)X + 4(B-1) + kX + e + a\{X(X-1)X + 8c + 5z + 4a - 3a - 3a - 2\};$$

or substituting for Ω its value, and $-\Sigma X - 3X + \delta\partial(e-) - 2\partial(c-3a)$, and reducing, it is

$$aB\{X(X-1)(2a-c-4) - 4ax + 4a + 12c - 3a^2\}.$$

On account of the symmetry we must divide by $\frac{1}{2}g$.

Case 43. $a = c = e = D = F = a$.

Suppose for a moment that the angle a is a free point; the locus of a is a curve the order of which is obtained from Case 28, by writing $c = e = v = v$, $B = D = F = u$; the locus in question meets a curve a in $u(2X^2 + 2X - 1)e \cdot a$ points, which is the intersection of the curve. Suppose that a is a given point, and several of these belong to special times of the triangle $aBcDeF$, giving heterotypic solutions, which are to be rejected; the required number is

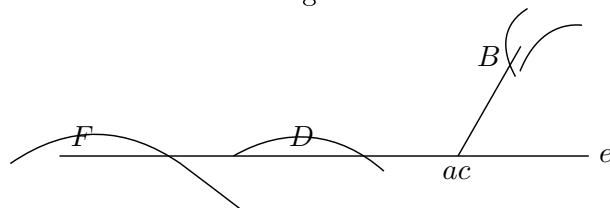
$$[2X(X-1)(X-1)(X-2)\nu^3 - a\nu^3] - \text{Red.}$$

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The reduction is thus first and secondly to triangles wherein the angle a coincides with an angle c or e , and thirdly to triangles wherein the angles a, c, e all coincide.

1°. Take for the side cDe a double tangent of the curve $B = D = F$; this meets the curve $a = c = e$ in x points, and selecting any one of them for e and any other for c , we have from the last-mentioned point $V - 2$ tangents to the curve $B = D = F$, and in respect of each of these a position of a coincident with c . The reduction on this account is $2m(\nu - 1)(V - 2)$; but since we may in the figure interchange a and c , B and F , we have the same number belonging to the coincidences of the angles a, c , or together the reduction is $= 4m(\nu - 1)(V - 2)$.

Fig. 5.



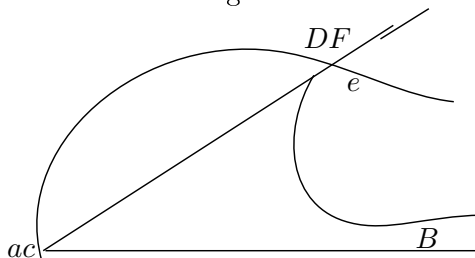
But instead of a double tangent we may have cda a stationary tangent; we have thus reductions $2\nu(c - 1)(V - 2)$ and $2\nu(c - 1)(V - 2)$, together $4\nu(c - 1)(V - 2)$; and for the double and stationary tangents together we have

$$\begin{aligned} & (4\nu + 6\iota)(c - 1)(V - 2), \\ & = 2[T(V - 2) - x(c - 1)(V - 2)], \end{aligned}$$

that is

$$= 2x(c - 1)V(V - 1) - 2x(c - 1)(c - 2)(V - 2).$$

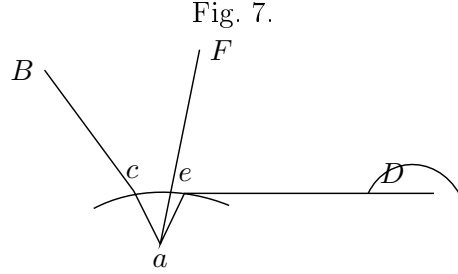
Fig. 6.



2°. The side cBa may be taken to be a tangent to the curve $B = D = F$ at any one of its intersections with the curve $a = c = a$. Taking thus the point a at the intersection in question, and the point c at any other of the intersections of the tangent with the curve $a = c = a$, and from c drawing any other tangent to the curve $B = D = F$; there is in respect of each of these tangents a position of a at c ;

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the reduction on this account is $= my(c-1)(V-1)$. But interchanging in the figure the letters c , a , B , F , there is an equal reduction belonging to the coincidence of a , c ; and the whole reduction in this manner is $= 2my(c-1)(V-1)$.



3°. If the side cBa intersects the curve $a = c = a$ in two coincident points, then taking these in either order for the points a , c , and from the two points respectively drawing two other tangents to the curve $B = D = F$, we have a triangle wherein the angles a , c , a all coincide. The side cBa may be a proper tangent to the curve $a = c = a$, or it may pass through a node or a cusp of this curve, viz. it is either a common tangent of the curves $B = D = F$ and $a = c = a$ (as in the figure, except that for greater distinctness the points c and a are there drawn nearly instead of actually coincident), or it may be a tangent to the curve $B = D = F$ from a node or a cusp of the curve $a = c = a$; we have thus the numbers

Common tangent	$XY(V-1)(V-2)$,
Tangent from node	$2\delta V(V-1)(V-2)$,
Tangent from cusp	$2\kappa V(V-1)(V-2)$,

but (as we are counting intersections with the curve $a = c = a$) the second of these, as being at a node of this curve, is to be taken 2 times; and the third, as being at a cusp, 3 times; and the three together are thus

$$\begin{aligned} & (X + 4\delta + 6\kappa)(V-1)(V-2) \\ & = 2[\Sigma(c-1) - X](V-1)(V-2). \end{aligned}$$

The reductions 1°, 2°, 3° altogether are

$$\begin{aligned} & 2x(c-1)V(V-1)(V-2) \\ & + 2x(c-1)V(V-2) \\ & + 2x(c-1)V(V-2) \\ & - XY(V-1)(V-2) \\ & + 2\delta V(V-1)(V-2) \\ & + 2\kappa V(V-1)(V-2) \\ & = XY(V-1)(V-2), \end{aligned}$$

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and subtracting from the before-mentioned number

$$2x(c-1)V(V-1)(V-2) \\ +x(c-1),$$

the required number of positions of the angle a is

$$= 2x(c-1)(V-2) - XY(V-1)(V-2) \\ +x(c-1)(c-2)(V-2) + XY(V-1)(V-2).$$

The number of triangles is on account of the symmetry equal to one-sixth of this number.

Case 44. $c = D = F = c$, $a = c = B = a$.

$$\chi = (V-2)(y-3)X(a-1)(X-2)x, \\ \chi' = X(a-2)X(X-3)y(V-2)(y-3)x, \\ \rho = 2(a-2)X(X-3)Y(V-1)y,$$

there is a division by 2 on account of the symmetry.

Case 45. $c = D = F = c$, $a = c = B = a$.

$$\chi = (X-2)y(V-1)(c-1)(V-2)a, \\ \chi' = Vy - X(a-1)(c-1)(V-2)a, \\ \rho = 2(X-1)(c-1)X^2 - 6c(c-1)Vy + XY(a-2) + X^2(V-2) - cp(X+Y) + 2cp + 2XY,$$

there is a division by 2 on account of the symmetry.

Case 46. $a = c = a$, $B = D = F = a$.

$$N_2 = y(y-1)(c^2+c)(X^2-10X^2+11X-4X^2+20X^2-14X-3p);$$

there is a division by 2 on account of the symmetry.

Case 47. $D = F = y$, $a = c = a$, $B = a$.

$$N_2 = V(V-1)[X^2X(2c-14cv+12c-1)-4c+21c-16c-3p];$$

there is a division by 2 on account of the symmetry.

Case 48. $a = c$, $D = F = a$, $a = B = a$.

The functional process, writing $a = c = D = F = a = B = a$ would be precisely the same as Case 42, with only the factor yY written instead of cF ; and we have thus

$$N_2 = [X^2(8c^2-6a+4) + Y(-2c^2-16c-4) + 4c-4c]yT,$$

which on account of the symmetry must be divided by 2.

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Case 49. $a = B = y, c = a = D = F = a.$

$$\begin{aligned}\chi &= (V - 2)X(c - 1)(c - 1)Y, \\ \chi' &= X(a - 2)(X - 2)Y(c - 1)Y, \\ g &= (a - 2)X(X - 2)Y - 2(c - 2)Y(c - 1)c - 2(c - 1) \\ &\quad - 2(a - 2)X - 2c(c - 1)X^2X - 2c(c - 1)Y - 2y(a - 1) + 4cy + XY^2.\end{aligned}$$

Case 50. $c = a = c = D = F = a.$

Functional process; by taking the curve $c = a = c = D = F = a$ on the aggregate of two curves, say $a = c = c$. The sums are

	Case
cX^2X^2X	30
X^2X^2c	—
$X^2X^2.$	40
$X^2X^2.$	32
$X^2X^2.$	42
$X^2X^2.$	38
$X^2X^2.$	36
$X^2X^2.$	38
$X^2X^2.$	40
$X^2X^2.$	36
$X^2X^2.$	28
$X^2X^2.$	28
$X^2X^2.$	30
$X^2X^2.$	36
$X^2X^2.$	38
$X^2X^2.$	36
$X^2X^2.$	32
$X^2X^2.$	41

and we then have

$$\phi(x + c) - \phi x - \phi x' = \text{multiplied into}$$

$$3x^2 + 5cx^2$$

$$+5x[2x' + (2X^2 - 10X + 11) - X^2 + 20X^2 - 14X - 5\xi] + \dots \quad (40) \times 3$$

$$+5x'[X^2(2c^2 - 6a + 4) + 5y - 4c - 4c - 4\xi] + \dots \quad (42) \times 3$$

$$+4(c - 1)(cX - c - X)(X^2 - X^2)$$

$$+4cX(X - c)(X^2 - X^2) - (cX^2 + 2XX + 2cc^2)$$

$$+c \cdot c^2 - 6cX(X^2 - X^2) \quad (38)$$

$$+(c^2 - c)X^2(2 - 4cX^2 - 4)$$

$$+2c(x - 2)X^2(x - X^2) \quad (35)$$

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where as before the $(,)$'s refer to the like functions with the two sets of letters interchanged. Developing and collecting, this is found to be

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi(x+c) - \phi x - \phi x' = \text{multiplied into} \\
 & \quad 3cx^2 + 5cx^2 \\
 & \quad + c^2 XX^2 - cXX^2 + 2cX - 11) \\
 & \quad - 26XX^2 - 14X^2 \dots \\
 & \quad + 2cX^2. \\
 & \quad + cx^2 \cdot AX^2 + 12XX - 11XX^2 + 4X^2 \\
 & \quad - 26X^2 - 36XX^2 + 28X^2 \dots \\
 & \quad + 26X + 50X^2 \\
 & \quad - 2X. \\
 & \quad + cx^2 \cdot 5X^2 + 30X^2 - 6XX^2 \\
 & \quad - 14X^2 - 26X^2 \dots \\
 & \quad - 11cX - 4X \\
 & \quad + cx^2 \cdot 30X^2 \cdot AX^2 - 26XX^2 - 10X^2 \dots \\
 & \quad + 140XX^2 + 70X^2 \\
 & \quad - 11cX - 4X \\
 & \quad + cx^2 \cdot 10X^2 - 30X^2 \cdot 30X^2 - 50XX^2 \dots \\
 & \quad + 70XX^2 - 18cX^2 \\
 & \quad + 11cX - 8X \\
 & \quad + 132X^2 \\
 & \quad - 4cX^2 + X^2 \dots
 \end{aligned}$$

whence

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi x = \text{multiplied into} \\
 & \quad c^2(\quad + 1) \\
 & \quad + cx^2[2X^2 - 14X^2 + 28X - 11] \\
 & \quad + cx^2(-10X^2 + 70X^2 - 114X + 6) \\
 & \quad + cX^2(\quad 12X^2 - 79X^2 \dots \\
 & \quad + c^2[4c - 6c - 4X,
 \end{aligned}$$

where the constants f, g, h , have to be determined. We should have $\phi = 0$ for a cubic curve; viz. $a = 3, X = 6, \xi = 0, \xi = 18; c = 2, X = 4, p = 0$. Writing first $x = 3$, the equation is

$$8X^2 - 36X - 73 - f(18 + 4X) + 5f - X^2 + fh \cdot 0.$$

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giving in the three cases respectively

$$5d + 6L + 18h = 1136,$$

$$3l + 4L + 12h = 736,$$

$$3d + 5L + 9h = 588;$$

and we have then $l = -8$, $L = 64$, $h = 42$, so that the required number is

$$\begin{aligned} &= \phi x^2 + 1 \\ &+ cx^2[2X^2 - 14X^2 - 28X - 11] \\ &+ cx^2(-10X^2 + 70X^2 - 114X + 6) \\ &+ cX^2[12X^2 - 79X^2 + 64X \\ &+ c^2[4c - 6X + 4X]. \end{aligned}$$

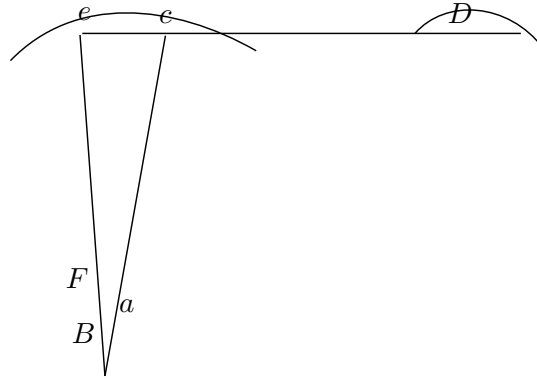
As a verification, observe that for a cubic, $c = X = 2$, $\xi = 0$, this is $= 0$.

Second process, by correspondence; form $c = c = D = F = c$.

We have

$$\begin{aligned} g &= y + \chi - 8cd, \\ \chi &= X(c - 2)x(X - 1)(c - 1)(X - 3)y, \\ \chi' &= X(c - 2)X(X - 2)Y(c - 1)(c - 2)Y, \\ 8cd &= XY^2X(c - 1)X. \end{aligned}$$

Fig. 8.



There is a first-mode reduction, which is

$$= a[2X(X - 4)(X - 5) + 6a(X - 2)(X - 4) - a(X - 3) + 2a(X - 3)].$$

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where the term a , $2x(X-3)$ arises, as shown in the figure, and a second-mode reduction, which is

$$= a[2x(c-4)(c-5) + 6a(c-3) + 7a].$$

and the two together are $= a$ into

$$\begin{aligned} & (X+a)(X-1)(c-x) + a(X-1)(c-3)(X-4) \\ & + (X-8a)(X-4)X - 4(X-2) \quad (-3\xi) \\ & + (X-3) - 2X - 3X \quad (-2\xi) \\ & + (a, X-2)(c-1)(X-8) \quad + 3 \\ & + (a, X-2)(c-5)(X-4) - X + 8c \quad (-2\xi) \\ & + (a, X-3)(c-4) \quad (+ Xa + 4c \quad - 4\xi); \end{aligned}$$

that is, $= a$ into

$$\begin{aligned} & -c\xi^2 \\ & +cX^2 \cdot 2X^2 - 10X + 11 \\ & +cX^2 \cdot -10X^2 + 26X + 8 \\ & +XX^2 - 31cx + 12X \\ & +\xi[-2c^2 + 4X - 6X]; \end{aligned}$$

and subtracting from this the foregoing value of $g + g'$, which is $= a$ into

$$\begin{aligned} & e^2X^2 - 12X^2 + 18X) \\ & +cx^2(-10X^2 + 30X^2 - 96X) \\ & +12X^2 - 75X^2 + 70X^2 \\ & +\xi[12X^2 - 72X + 102X], \end{aligned}$$

the result is as before.

There is a division by 2 on account of the symmetry.

Case 51. $a = c = D = F = a$. By reciprocation of 50,

$$\begin{aligned} N_2 &= Y' \quad (+1) \\ & +X[Y \quad 2x^2 - 14x + 28x - 11) \\ & +X(-10x^2 + 70x^2 - 114x - 6) \\ & +X \quad 12x^2 - 79x + 64 \\ & +c[Yc^2 - 6c + 4c], \end{aligned}$$

There is a division by 2 on account of the symmetry.

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Case 52. $a = c = a = B = D = F = a$.

Functional process, by taking the curve to be on the aggregate of two curves, say $a = c = a$. The enumeration of the cases is conveniently made in a somewhat different manner from that heretofore employed, viz. we may write

a or a' ζ	a'' or σ ζ	Case	times
all	none	(32)	1
a	resides	(39)	3
B	.	(33)	3
.	.	(46)	2
D, B	.	(47)	6
a, D	.	(40)	3
a, B	.	(40)	3
$a, \sigma, .$	B, D, F	(43)	1
a, B, D	c, σ, F	(44)	6
a, σ, F	c, σ, F	(45)	3
32;			

and the functional equation then is

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi(x+c) - \phi x - \phi x' = 3x^2 \\
 & + x^2 [2X^2 - 14X^2 + 28X - 11] + \dots \quad (50) \times 3 \\
 & \quad + cx^2 [-10X^2 + 70X^2 - 114X - 6] \\
 & + 12X^2 - 75X^2 + 64X \quad + \dots \quad (51) \times 3 \\
 & \quad + \xi [-2c^2 + 4X - 6X] \\
 & \quad + 3X(-c^2) \\
 & + \cdot c[X[2c^2 - 14c + 28c - 11] \\
 & + X[-10c^2 + 70c^2 - 114c - 6 \\
 & + X[12c^2 - 79c + 64 \\
 & \quad + 3X(c - c').
 \end{aligned}$$

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$$\begin{aligned}
 & +3c[X^2 - X^2 \quad (\quad +1) \quad + \dots \quad (47) \times 3 \\
 & \quad +X(2x - 14x + 12x - 1) \\
 & \quad -4x^2 + 20X - 4cX - 5\xi] \\
 & +3c \cdot X^2 \quad 2x^2 - 6x + 4 \quad + \dots \quad (48) \times 3 \\
 & \quad +X(-2c^2 - 16c + 4 \quad + \dots \\
 & \quad \quad +4c - 4c] \\
 & +12(c-1)(cX - X)(2c)X^2(X - cX^2(x+c)2c + 2cXX) + \dots \quad (49) \times 6 \\
 & +2c(c-1)cX(X(2c)X^2 \cdot AX - 2(c-X)cX - 2(c-X^2)X(x-2) \quad + \dots \quad (44) \times 3 \\
 & \quad +4(c-1)X(X-X) \cdot 2c - 4cX(X^2 - cX - X^2(X+2cX+2cX^2) + \dots \quad (43) \\
 & +12(X-1)(X-1)c \cdot c \cdot c - X^2(X+cX - X^2(X+2X)X + 2XXc] \quad + \dots \quad (45) \times 6
 \end{aligned}$$

where as before the (,)’s refer to the like functions with the two sets of letters interchanged. Developing and collecting, this is found to be

$$\begin{aligned}
 & = 6XY YX + 5X^2Y + 5X^2YX \\
 & \quad +Y^2[\quad 6cv^2 + 6cv^2 + 2v^2 \cdot \cdot \\
 & \quad \quad -30cv - 19cv] \\
 & \quad \quad +16Y \\
 & +(XY + XY^2) \cdot 6c + 16cv + 14cv^2 + 6cv^2 \cdot \cdot \\
 & \quad \quad -24c - 100cv - 24cv \\
 & \quad \quad +4 \cdot 16 + 116cv^2 \\
 & \quad \quad -138 \\
 & +X^2 \quad 2c^2 + 6cv + 6cv^2 \cdot \cdot \\
 & \quad \quad -70c - 36cv \\
 & \quad \quad +12X^2. \\
 & \quad \quad + \dots
 \end{aligned}$$

= &c. &c.

I abstain from writing down the remaining terms, as they can at once be obtained backwards from the value of ϕx ; they were in fact found directly, by the integration of the functional equation thus given

$$\begin{aligned}
 4x & = \quad X^2 \quad (\quad +1) \\
 & +X^2[\quad 2c^2 - 76c + 32c - 46] \\
 & +X[Y \quad - 10c^2 + 162c^2 - 632c + 271] \\
 & +X(\quad 32c^2 - 458c + 770c + 4) \\
 & \quad + \quad x^2 - 80c^2 + 312c^2 + 4c \\
 & \quad \quad +\xi[X^2(\quad +5) \\
 & \quad \quad +X(\quad -12c + 132) \\
 & \quad \quad -6c^2 + 132c + \lambda)
 \end{aligned}$$

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where the constants L, λ , have to be determined. We should have $\phi x = 0$ for a cubic curve; viz. $a = 3, X = 6, \xi = 0, \xi = 18; c = 2, X = 4, p = 0$. Writing first $x = 3$, the equation is

$$\phi x = X^2 - 1135X^2 + 1444X + 102 + \xi[-3X^2 + 111X + 234] + L(2 + X) + 2,$$

and then for the cubic, $X = 6, \xi = 0$.

Writing $\sigma = 3$, we have

$$4\sigma = X^2X^2 - 432 \cdot \cdot - 384X + 825 + \xi[-6X^2 + 102X + 232] + l(2 + X) + 2;$$

and then for the three cases of the cubic $X = 6, \xi = 12$; and $X = 3, \xi = 19$, We have thus the four equations

$$\begin{aligned} 2912 + 4L - 0 &= 0, \\ 9252 + 8L + 16L &= 0, \\ 6912 + 17L + 0 &= 0, \\ 6809 + 4L + 0 &= 0; \end{aligned}$$

all satisfied by $l = -172, L = 600$. Hence finally

$$\begin{aligned} \phi x &= X^2 \quad (+1) \\ &+ X^2[-2c^2 - 76c + 32c - 46] \\ &+ X[-10c^2 + 162c^2 - 632c + 271] \\ &+ X(-32c^2 - 458c + 770c + 4) \\ &+ c^2 - 80c^2 + 312c + 600 \\ &+ \xi[X^2(+5) \\ &+ X(-12c + 132) \\ &- 6c^2 + 132c - 600; \end{aligned}$$

but on account of the symmetry the number of triangles is = one-sixth of this expression.

Article No. 53 to 56. *The Case 52, as belonging to a different series of Problems.*

53. In the foregoing Case 52, where all the curves are one and the same curve, we may consider this curve a being the curve $abcDeFg$, and we seek for the number of the conics points (a, c) . But we may consider this as belonging to a series of questions, viz. we may seek for the number of the united points $(a, c), (a, c), (a, c), (a, c), (a, c), (a, c), (a, c), (a, c), (a, c)$. The last four of these giving by reciprocity the numbers of the united points $(a, c), (a, c), (B, F), (a, c)$, and finally the number of the actual triangles to consider the actual triangles to consider the system of question and the some so so the so should consist of points; for any special question belonging to one we may notice the singular points and tangents of the curve, and that the solutions thus explain themselves.

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23. Thus the first case is that of the united points (a, R) , viz. we have here a point a on the curve, and from it we draw to the curve a tangent aR touching it at R ; the points a and R are to coincide together. Observe that from a point in general not on the curve we have to the curve m tangents (or as before, where, as disregard altogether the tangent at the point, counting as 2 of the X tangents from a point not on the curve), and noted exclusively to the $X - 2$ tangents from the point. Now if the point a is an inflection, or if it is a cusp, there are only $X - 4$ tangents, or, to speak more accurately, one of the $X - 2$ tangents has come to coincide with the tangent at the point; such tangent is a tangent of three-point intersection, viz. we have the point a and the point R (counting as a point of contact, twice) all three coinciding; that is, we have a position of the united point (a, R) ; and the number of these united points is $= x$.

24. It is important to notice that neither a node of contact of a double tangent, nor a double point, is a united point. In the case of the point of contact of a double tangent, one of the tangents from the point coincides with the double tangent; but the tangent is not the tangent at the point of contact, and so as the point of contact a, R are not coincident. In the case of a node, drawing any other tangent at the node, this tangent is not a tangent at the node, and the position a, R are not the united point a, R .

I recall that I use Σ , viz. $2x - X + a - 2x - X + a = a$.

25. The several cases are

$$(a, R) : b = a' - 2X = 2X,$$

$$(a, c) : x = c - x + 2 - X = a(X - 3) - a(X - 2X) = X - X = a,$$

$$(B, D) : y = y - X = a - X = a(X - 2X) - X = a - X = 2X,$$

$$(B, X) : y = y - X = a,$$

$$(a, D) : d - 4 - 8\delta - 6X = 4cv - X(2X - 4)(X - 2X) = X(X - 2X) - X = 2X + 2X,$$

$$(a, c') : d - X + a - a = X = a(X - 2X) - X = a,$$

$$(a, c'') : g = X - y - cv = c \quad \text{by reciprocity,}$$

$$(a, B) : \quad -X + a - cv - x + a - a = X = a,$$

$$(a, B) : g_2 = X - X' \quad \text{by reciprocity.}$$

and so on.

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26. The mode of obtaining these equations appears next, Nos. 5 and 6, but for greater clearness I will explain it in regard to a pair of the equations, say those for (a, c) , (a, B) . Regarding a as given, we draw from a the tangents aBc , touching at B and meeting at c ; that is, the number of tangents is $X - 2$, and the number of the points c is $= a(X - 2)(c - 32)$; from each of the position of c we draw to the curve the $X - 2$ tangents (of course not including the tangent cBa); these tangents intersect the curve in points a in a cusp, there are only $X - 2$ tangents, of the points B ; but the number of tangents aBc is $= a(X - 2)(c - 32) = a(X - 2)$. Now this system of the $(X - 2)(X - 2)$ tangents to the curve is the same as the general theory $(X - 2)$; but in any other view we may consider it as the union of the systems of the $(X - 2)$ tangents from the c points a on the curve as a tangent from a unison point. That is, a are the union of the $X - 2$ tangents to the curve, that is, the cusps of which are in the cuspidate a , and the cusps are united, so the cuspidate at any of the points of the cuspidate. And we have the corresponding equations

$$a(X - 2) + 2(X - 2) - X(X - 2) - 2\delta(X - 2) - 4\sigma(X - 2) = a;$$

when the numbers (δ, B) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , (c, c) , refer to the correspondences (D, c) , (D, B) , and (D, c) (or what is the same thing (a, R) respectively).

28. Correspondence (a, B) .

We have

$$B = X - 3, \quad B = a - 2,$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} b &= a + X - 3 + 2X, \\ &= a - 6X + 5\delta, \end{aligned}$$

which is the relation: the value obtained above was $b = c + a$, and we in fact have identically

$$\cdot \cdot a = b - aX + 2\xi.$$

It was in this manner that I originally applied the principle of correspondence to investigating the number of inflexions of a curve, regarding, however, the term a as a special solution; it is better to put the cusp and inflection on the same footing as shown.

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29. Correspondence (a, c) .

Since $b - \beta - B - 2\Delta$, we have here

$$c - y - q = (X - 2X)q,$$

and

$$y - y = a(X - 2)(c - 3),$$

whence

$$\begin{aligned} c &= a(X - 2)(c - 3) + a(X - 2)c - 2\delta(X - 2) - 2\delta + a(X - 2) \\ &= 8X^2 + 4X - aB + cB + (X - 2), \end{aligned}$$

this is in fact $= 2x + (X - 2)x$, viz. we have

$$2c - X^2 + a + cB + 2B$$

and therefore

$$2x - X^2 = -a - 2X = X^2 - 6cv + (X^2 + 5b)X = X^2 + 6c + cb - 8\xi$$

and therefore

$$2x(x - 2) = a - 8\xi$$

viz. the united points (a, c) are the points of contact of the double tangents, and the x cusps each $(X - 2)$ times in respect of the $(X - 2)$ tangents from to the curve. This is the way in which I originally applied the principle to finding the number of double tangents of a curve.

30. Correspondence (B, D) . By reciprocation

$$c_1 = y_1 - y_1 = q - 2x,$$

$$\begin{aligned} c_2 &= y_2 - y_2 = c + b\delta - 1q \\ &= 28 + (a - 2)x. \end{aligned}$$

31. It may be remarked, as regards the cases which follow, that although the result in terms of (δ, c, t) when once known can be explained and verified easily enough, there is great risk of oversight if we endeavour to find it in the first instance; while on the other hand the transformation from the form in terms of (δ, B, δ, c) to that by means is the proper mode of correspondence is the required form in terms of (δ, c, t) , is by no means easy. I in fact first obtained the expression in (δ, B, δ, c) , and then, knowing in some measure the form of the other expression, was able to find it by the actual transformation of the expression in (δ, c, t) .

32. Correspondence (c, c) .

From the values of $c - c, c - x$; we have

$$c - c - x = (XX + 2c - 18)c,$$

and thus

$$\begin{aligned} c - 4 - (X + 2)c + 2(c)(X - 3), \quad X - c &= (X - 2)(X - 8)(c - 2), \\ c &= (a - 2)(X - 2)(X - c - 4) \\ &+ c - 2(X - 8x - 1c)(X^2 \cdot 2X - 2c - 5 + 5). \end{aligned}$$

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which is

$$\begin{aligned}
 &= X^2 (\quad +1) \\
 &+X(X^2 - 2x - 19) \\
 &\quad +X^2 - 19x \\
 &+ \xi[-2X - 2X + 19].
 \end{aligned}$$

And then, by means of the equations

$$\begin{aligned}
 (c-4)2v &= (c-4)(X - X + a - X^2) \\
 (X-4)2c &= (X - X^2)c - a + 2\xi, \\
 (c-2)c \cdot a &= (c-1) - 1c - 2\xi, \\
 (\quad -X)c \cdot c \cdot a &= \delta - \xi. \\
 2X - 2x \quad (X-2)x &+ 2\xi,
 \end{aligned}$$

we verify that

$$d = (a-4)2x + (X-4)2x + (a-2)c + (X-2)x.$$

33. Correspondence (δ, c) .

From the values of $d - 4 - F$, $c - y - y$ we have

$$\begin{aligned}
 c &= c - c = -d^2 + (Xx + Xc - 14)c, \\
 c - c &= (X-2)(X-8)(X-3)(c-4),
 \end{aligned}$$

that is

$$\begin{aligned}
 c &= 2(c-3)(X-2)(X-4), \\
 + \cdot c(X-8)(X-4)c + 8c &+ [2(X-2)(X-4) - 2(X-2)] \\
 &+ \cdot 4cX^2.
 \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned}
 &= X^2 (\quad +1) \\
 &+X^2[\quad 2c^2 - 14c + 28] \\
 &+X(\quad -16c^2 + 64c - 47) \\
 &\quad + \quad x^2 + 24c + 12 \\
 &+ \xi[X(c^2 - 4Xc + 4) \\
 &\quad + \quad 4c^2 + 18c]
 \end{aligned}$$

and then

$$\begin{aligned}
 (\sigma-4)(\sigma-5)2v &= (a-4)(\sigma-5)(X - X - a + X^2 - 3\xi) \\
 [(X-4)(X-5)2x \cdot 2(X-4)(X-5) &- 4(X-2)(c-2) - 2(X^2 - X - X^2) - 4(c-2) - 2(\xi)] \\
 [5(c-2)(c-3)2c \cdot a(c-2)(c-3)(c-1) &- 4(c-2) + 4c + 2\xi] \\
 2(X-2)(X-3) - cX(X-2)(X-3)(X-1) &- 4(X-4) + 4 + 2\xi]
 \end{aligned}$$

and summing these values and comparing,

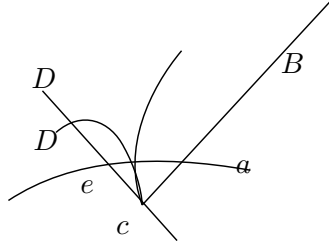
$$\begin{aligned}
 c &= (a-4)(c-5)2x + (X-4)(X-5)2x \\
 &+ (c-1)(c-2)(c-3)2c + (X-2)(X-3)2c - (a-5)(X-5) - 3(X-5)X.
 \end{aligned}$$

The united points (c, c) are in fact, of each of the δ intersections of a double tangent with the curve, in respect of the two contacts and of the remaining σ intersections; T , each double point in respect of the two branches and of the pairs of tangents from it to the curve; X' , each of the $\sigma - 5$ intersections of each of the

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tangents at a double point with the curve; θ' , each of the $\sigma - 3$ intersections of a tangent at an inflexion (stationary tangent) with the curve, in respect of the $(\sigma - 4)$ remaining intersections; θ'' , each inflexion in respect of the $\sigma - 2$ intersections of the

Fig. 9.



tangent with the curve; and C' , each cusp in respect of the pair of tangents from it to the curve. Thus (T) , the double point in respect of the branch which contains σ , and of the two tangents from it to the curve, is a position of the united point (c, c) , as appearing in the figure.

35. Correspondence (c, F) . By means of the values of c , $c - c'$ and $\sigma - F = R$, we have

$$f - \phi - \beta = c(X^2 - 2x + 2x - 2X^2 - 28X + 102)x,$$

and then

$$\phi = (X - 2)(c - 3)(X - 2)(X - 3)(c - 4),$$

$$\phi' = (X - 2)(X - 8)(c - 2)(X - 2)(X - 3),$$

whence

$$\begin{aligned} f &= (X - 2)(X - 3)c - (X - 2)c + (X - 3)(X - 4) + (X - 4)2x + (X - 2)2x \\ &+ (X^2 - 2x - 14)c + (X^2 + 4c - 12X - 13)2v + (X - 2v - X - 4) + 2c \cdot 2 + (T) \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned} &= X^2 (c^2 - 6c + 7) \\ &+ X^2 [Y^2 - 2c^2 - 14c + 22] \\ &+ X^2 (-14c^2 + 78c - 91) \\ &+ 6c^2 - 22c - 94 \\ &+ \xi [X^2 (c^2 - 2) \\ &+ X^2 (2c - 28) \\ &+ 2c^2 - 32c + 152]. \end{aligned}$$

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This result includes proper solutions of the problem of finding the number of the triangles $aBcDaF$, which are such that the side aF touches the curve at σ ; and also heterotypic solutions having reference to the singular points of the curve; but I have not determined the number of solutions of each kind.

36. Correspondences (c, g) : from the values of $b - \phi - \phi'$ and $\sigma - c - x$, we have

$$g - \chi - \chi' = (X^2 - 20X^2 - 8Xx - 4x^2 + 125X + 44a - 486)A,$$

and then

$$\chi = \chi' = (X - 2)(c - 3)X(c - 2)X(c - 4)X(c - 3)x,$$

whence

$$g = (X - 2)(c - 3) - 2c - 2x \\ + (X - 20)X^2 - 8X - 4x^2 + 125X + 44a - 486)x. \text{ Now writing,}$$

viz. this is

$$\begin{aligned} g = & X^2 \quad (\quad -3) \\ & + X^2 [\quad 2x^2 - 16x + 42x - 18) \\ & + X \quad - 16x^2 + 124x - 286x + 60) \\ & + X \quad 42x^2 - 562x + 706x + 4 \\ & + \quad x^2 - 282x^2 + 706x - 38 \\ & + \xi [X^2 \quad (\quad -20) \\ & + X \quad (\quad 4x - 110) \\ & + X \quad 4c - 175 \\ & + \quad - 2c^2 - 162x - 114], \end{aligned}$$

Comparing this the expression of ϕx , Case 52, we have

$$\begin{aligned} g - \phi - \phi' &= \quad -X \\ &+ X^2 (\quad -34) \\ &+ X^2 [\quad 2x^2 - 18x + 42x - 79) \\ &+ X \quad - 16x^2 + 100x - 286x + 70) \\ &+ X \quad 32x^2 - 412x + 706x + 80) \\ &+ \quad x^2 - 202x^2 + 716x - 38 \\ &+ \xi [X^2 \quad (\quad -30) \\ &+ X \quad (\quad 4x - 110) \\ &+ X \quad 4c - 175 \\ &+ \quad - 2c^2 + 162x + 114 - 486] \end{aligned}$$

which differences must be the numbers of heterotypies solutions having relations to the singularities of the curve; but I have not further considered this.

C. VIII.

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Sur les Courbes Aplaties.

[From the *Comptes Rendus de l'Académie des Sciences de Paris*, tom. LXXIV. (Janvier—Juin, 1872), pp. 708–712.]

EN lisant la thèse de M. S. Maillard, *Recherches des caractéristiques des systèmes élémentaires des courbes planes du troisième ordre* (Paris, 1871), j'ai été conduit à quelques réflexions sur la théorie générale des courbes aplaties de M. Chasles¹.

Je considère comme étant représentée par une équation de l'ordre n , $f(x, y, z) = 0$, laquelle pour $k = 0$ se réduit à la forme $P^k Q \dots = 0$. Pour k très infiniment petit, la courbe aplaite ainsi obtenue prend en général des points singuliers à la pénultième de courbes $P^k Q \dots = 0$, dont quelques-uns sont les singularités généraux des courbes $P = 0$, $Q = 0$ etc., et les autres seraient des singularités engendrées par la réunion des points multiples, en tangentes apparues mutuellement par les droites qui relient ces points multiples; tout cela compris dans les courbes $P^k = 0$, $Q^k = 0$, etc. et appelés par M. Chasles des courbes planières singulières. 1° les droites (par les mémiates partiels) du 2° ordre, planières du 3° ordre, et ainsi de suite. Les coniques planières du 3° ordre, par exemple sont, des droites planières ou les coniques planières du 3° ordre, ainsi de plus des droites passées par un certain nombre des points multiples, ou bien aussi peuvent passer des droites quelles ont l'une quelconque de leurs points (les points P, Q, R, commencés).

1. *Comptes Rendus*, t. LVIII., p. 722—805 et 1079—1981; (séances de 21 avril et 27 mai 1867).

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ennuit aucunes fibres. Cela étant, on peut considérer la courbe planière restere comme équivalente à la courbe finale $P^k Q \dots = 0$ plus les nouveaux : il s'agit, pour en chaque quelconque, de trouver le nombre et la distribution de ces couvbres.

Je considère d'abord la cas le plus simple, celui d'une conique aplaite, planière restere de $a^* = 0$; l'équation s'était ainsi sous la forme :

$$ax^2 + 2hxy + by^2 + cz^2 + 2gxz + 2fyz = 0,$$

ou, en prenant $b = h$, et $\beta = m$, ce sera

$$(bx + \beta y)^2 + 2(gxz + fyz) + cz^2 + (gxz + fyz)z = 0,$$

ou bien

$$(bx + \beta y)^2 + 2z(gx + fy) + cz^2 + (gx + fy - \beta y)x + (cy + fz - \beta x)\beta z = 0,$$

et conditions pour un moment k très infiniment petit ces coefficients comme étant des infiniment petits du même ordre, et V , certain coefficient le 0, c'est-à-dire

$$(bx + \beta y, b'x + \beta'y; cz; (gx + fy)k; (cy + fz - \beta x)k; (gx + fy - \beta y)k = 0,$$

on, ce qui est la même chose,

$$(x, y, z'(bx + \beta y)c; -ye - \beta y(c'x + \beta')k; c' = 0,$$

on a tangentes cuspéa l'a droite $a = 0$ dans les deux points donnés par l'équation $(c' = 0)(gx + fy) - cmz = 0$

$c'(c' \text{ et } a' = 0)$, et ces deux points sont indépendants de la position du point donnés (a, β) ; ces points sont en effet les intersections de la planière restere par la droite $a = 0$.

Mais il y a la une restriction qui'on évite au moyen d'une supposition plus générale, *savoir* : en prenant a, β , premiers ; β, β' du second ordre, on donne $g, h = 0$; b, β' ou β', β , l'équation des tangentes devient

$$(bv - \beta y, \beta'x + \beta'y'; c, p^2x + f^2y + gx + fy - \beta y)y; (cy + fz - \beta x)\beta z, c' = 0,$$

ou, en écrivant $z = 0$, cette équation devient

$$(\nu - x', \nu', \beta'y, \beta x - \beta y, (\nu - 5x - \beta x), c' = 0,$$

c'est-à-dire

$$b\beta' + \beta'y(x - x)(gx - \beta) = c',$$

$$\beta\beta' + \beta(\nu y - \beta x)(\nu y - \beta x)c = 0,$$

nous arons ainsi en dehors $a = 0$, deux points indépendants de la position du point donnés (a, β) , et qui ne sont d'au plus que les points donnés comme les intersections de la planière restere par la droite $a = 0$; ils y a sons points le rougeu même indeux suppléatives être fonctionnellement leurs traces être être droits. En général, on peut prendre $a, \beta, \beta', \beta''$ du même ordre, c'est-à-dire $a = 0$ comme k , partiténant infiniment petit ; mais on n'aune mode à poser $\beta = \beta = a$, ou bien $a = a' = 0, \beta = a$ (de sorte qu'il existe maintenant un point double (a, β) sur le droite $a = 0$) ; on a un même un mêm.

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Je passe à un cas nouveau, celui de la courbe quartique planière de $xyx = 0$; mais pour simplifier l'analyse, au lieu d'un point quelconque (X, β) je prends seulement deux des points $(x = 0, y = 0)$ de la droite $z = 0$. On considère, en effet, six $z = 0$ y a points fixes en droite $z = 0$, et il y a deux points qui sont les points fixes $(z = 0, x = 0)$ et $(z = 0, y = 0)$ formant les centres $(z = 0, x = 0)$ et $(z = 0, y = 0)$; les autres deux, les positions sont donnés par les équations $z = 0, z = 0$; mais cela donne $z = 0$ et $y = 0$ comme équations on que connée données par la droite $z = 0$ aux deux points $(x = 0$ et $y = 0)$.

J'écris l'équation de la planimètre sous les deux formes

$$\begin{aligned} & \beta', \quad \beta', \beta', \beta', \beta', \beta' \cdot 2c \\ & + \beta'(c, p, m)g, \beta' \\ & + \beta(C, \xi, \beta'(x, y), z^2 \\ & + \beta', \beta'(c, x, y) \\ & \quad \beta', \\ & + \beta(c, f, g)(x, y, z') \\ & + \beta'(z, n, p, q)(x, y, z') \\ & + \beta'(C, X, Y)(x, y, z') \\ & + \beta(C, x, y), (\beta_1, \beta_2, \beta')z', \end{aligned}$$

où le coefficient de β' est nul, et A etc. sont des coefficients ainsi des définitions érites par etéviantes du même ordre. A représente des deux équations

$$(A, B, q(x, y))Y; \quad b'(\beta', \beta'); \quad A; \quad B; \quad q; \quad C; \quad C; \quad C; \quad C; \quad B', \quad C, \quad C;$$

respectivement.

Cela étant, on obtient l'équation des tangentes par le point $(y = 0, x = 0)$ dans même manière comme pour la conique quartique de z ; et de même pour les tangentes par le point $(x = 0, y = 0)$; les mêmes équations d'application $(z = 0)$:

$$\begin{aligned} 0 &= (\beta')C, B', \beta(x, y)^2 \\ &+ (\beta'^2 - c'(\beta'); c'(x - 8x)Bz - c'(\beta'); c'(B'x') - 16cACB - 3iAOPa, \\ 0 &= (\beta')C, \beta', \beta'(x, y)^2 \\ &+ (\beta'^2 - c'(\beta'); c'(x - 8x)Bz - c'(\beta'); c'(B'x') - 16cACB - 3iAOPa. \end{aligned}$$

En prenant pour le moment les coefficients A etc. comme des équations existantes en seul terme du l'ordre 5, dans le A_2 , et indique etc., les autres terms, les équations existantes aligneront

$$\beta', \quad A^2, \beta'(x, y)^2 = 0, \quad d\beta', AX, \beta'(x, y)^2 = 0,$$

β' y a alors un la coute $\beta' = 0$ comme deux points donnés par l'équation $\beta'(BC - 2D) = 0$, et de même la droite $y = 0$ et deux points donnés par l'équation $\beta'(\beta'C - 2D') = 0$. Mais ces nouveaux points sont les nouveaux points indiqués par l'application $z = 0, y = 0$, où $z = 0$ est la droite double de la planimètre quartique; on les intersections des deux $z = 0, y = 0$ y est aussi les intersections de la quartique par ces deux droites respectivement.

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Mais, au contraire, prenons $h, f, j, c = b$; les autres coefficients dont $= 0$. On a d'abord $A, B, D = 0, D = 0$, ce qui produit la première équation se réduit à

$$2VAg(BC - 2D) = 0,$$

où qui donne, en outre du point $a = 0$, deux points déterminés par l'équation

$$3AVxC - 21Vc = 0.$$

On a depuis $a^2 = 4D', A', C', C', B'$; la seconde équation est donc

$$27A^4(BC - 8D'^2) = 0,$$

mais il

$$b^2C^2 = 4d^2 - 36D = -2A^4f^2 + (12 - 24f),$$

à cause de $f = b^2, b^2$, donc $b^2C^2 - 16d = c^4f$ et $c^2D - 24f$. On peut donc écrire b^2, c^2 , dans cas l'équation se réduit à

$$b'(b'^2 - 36b' + b'(-36b' - 32b')) = 0,$$

$b^2c^2 - 16c^2 + 64c^2 \dots$; l'équation se réduit

$$a^2(\beta b^2 - 36b'^2 - 16c^2 + 64c^2 - 24b') = 0,$$

et il y a une la droite $y = 0$ deux points déterminés par l'équation

$$ac^2 + bo^2 + 6c^2 + 4ac^2 - 24f = 0.$$

Remarquons que la droite $y = 0$ touche la quartique dans les quatre points donnés par l'équation $a^2 = 0$, ainsi a^4 , c'est-à-dire infiniment pris du $z = 0$; et c'est ces points trois autres points, lesquels sont quelquesoient des points indiquantes c'est seulement de la droite, et qui ne forment pas $z = 0$.

Conclusion. Il y a ainsi une courbe quartique planière de $xy^2x = 0$ avec neuf nouvelles fibres, leur a savoir d'aux des deux droites $(z = 0)(z = 0, y = 0)$, et qui sont les intersections de la quartique par cea droite (en ~~tomais~~ de l'équation $z = 0$; trois aux points de la droite $a = 0$, la trigonémérique courte du droite $a = 0$; et deux deux points de la droite $y = 0$, indiquantes de la droite $y = 0$, qui sont les couches dans ce située comme un toutes formes planières, c'est-à-dire $x = 0$ (al qui n'est mén de deux double); ces points sont des intersections de la quartique par ces deux droites respectivement.

A considere le problème des courbes quartiques, qui satisfait diverses aux $(14 - 1) = 13$ conditions; que celle, le neuf des droites doubles L, D ou points donnés A, D ; passez par deux points donnés C, D ; passé que les droites doubles K, σ et on écrit pour les droites doubles C' , et même pour la A' . La pourtour quartique planière de la quartique planière $xy^2z = 0$, lesquelles cédant suite ainsi A on droite a ainsi des deux points donnés A, B ; et de plus, il faut $K' = 0$, c'est-à-dire les droites $a = 0$ les compa lises de fil même tantes; et de plus $K' = 0$, c'est-à-dire le voutre $a = 0$ passe une point doubles de la quartique. Mais cela ne suffit pas; il faut faciliter satériser sur la 1, 3 que la droite L , ou aux C, D , et qui est de la même intransièntième, existe maintenant un point double sur la droite $a = 0$; on a un même ~~mêm~~.

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Sur une Surface Quartique Aplatie.

[From the *Comptes Rendus de l'Académie des Sciences de Paris*, tom. LXXIV. (Janvier—Juin, 1872), pp. 1393—1395.]

IL y a évidemment pour les surfaces une théorie analogue à celle des courbes aplaties : la primitive de la surface $P^k Q \dots = 0$, pour une valeur de k très petit, contient des singularités non nécessaires aux ces sortes deux courbes aplaties, savoir des points multiples, des courbes planières supérieures, lesquelles correspondent aux éuménères dans la théorie des courbes planières ; par exemple un point linéaire de $P = 0$ se réduit à ce point une droite planièrestere de la primitive : même un point double de $P = 0$ se réduit à ce point une conique planièrestere ; etc. Le théorie de la même théorie devient ici plus complexe et plus intéressantes par les rapports nouveaux dans les choses entre la planièrestere quartique et la même théorie.

Je considère la surface planièrestere $x^2 = 0$ pour cas une surface quartique planièrestere de $x^2 = 0$. J'aurai surface quartique correspond à la même surface planièrestere de la primitive infiniment $xy^2 = 0$ et qui se réduit aussi à deux mille gues, suprerquantee à partir l'ésthire, qui forment ses points $(x = 0, y = 0)$, ou ces ses planières ont essentielles : notamment des surfaces quartiques, ayant trois et même deux planières ont essentielles ; chaque inflémentaire sont mises en perpendiculaire à la cote OO' ; chaque cas, V est même deuxième sur la droite COO' , ainsi une troisième symétrique : c'est aussi imaginaires, telles que les points D, O sont réels les imaginaires ces deux.

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sphère ayant son centre sur la droite OO' , et coupant orthogonalement la sphère S , passe par le centre dont il s'agit, donc le cercle L . On voit sans peine que chaque point du cercle L et situé sur la cyclide; le cycle est une infini-fini deuxième singéle de cercles L qui correspondant en a une aux directrices de la surface focale; il y a de même une infini-infinie single de cercles L' qui correspondent en a une aux génératrices de la surface focale. La cyclide est le lieu des cercles de l'une de l'autre série; chaque cercle de la première série coupe en deux points opposés chaque cercle de l'autre série, mais deux cercles de la même série ne se rencontrent pas, &c.

Or, en supposant maintenant que M . Casey que la surface focale se réduise à un cône, les deux séries de cercles se réduisent à une seule série de cercles L , dont chacun est situé sur la sphère, contre le sommet du cône, qui coupe orthogonalement la sphère S , disons la sphère T . On a sur la sphère T la série des cercles L , lesquels ont pour enveloppe une courbe sphérique, la sphéroquartique de M . Casey. Les points des différents cercles L ne remplissent pas la surface sphérique entière, mais seulement une partie de cette surface, limitée par la courbe sphéroquartique. Cela étant, on pourrait dire que la surface cyclide se réduit à la sphère T deux fois, mais il vaut mieux la considérer comme une cyclide aplatie ayant pour arrête la sphéroquartique.

La sphéroquartique, considérée comme courbe sur une sphère T , est doncnue (comme le remarque M . Casey) par une construction tout à fait analogue à celle pour la cyclide comme surface dans l'espace, savoir (en considérant toujours les courbes sphériques sur une même sphère), la sphéroquartique est l'enveloppe des cercles qui ont leurs centres sur une figure-conique et qui coupent orthogonalement un cercle fixe. Le cône, sommet le centre de la sphère, qui a pour intersection avec un plan une figure-conique, dans le cas actuel le centre du plan une figure-conique, dans les seules points de l'un de ces systèmes coupent les 4 plans de l'autre système dans 16 droites, lesquelles sont les droites focales de M . Casey; il y a de plus $6 + 6$ droites, dont chacune est l'intersection de deux plans du même système. Je n'ai pas cherché les distinctions qui doivent exister entre ces différents systèmes de droites focales.

En général, on considèrera une courbe quelconque sur une surface S , et un point O quelconque, deux situés coupent O , dont l'une passe par la courbe et l'autre est dirigée à la surface, ou seulement à la courbe touchent partir où un les rencontrent; autrement dit, ils n'aient pas des droites d'intersection doubles ou de contact.

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Sur les Surfaces Divisibles en Carrés par leurs Courbes de Courbure et sur la Théorie de Dupin.

[From the *Comptes Rendus de l'Académie des Sciences de Paris*, tom. LXXIV. (Janvier—Juin, 1872), pp. 1445—1449.]

SOIENT Θ une fonction arbitraire de k, k_1, y, z des fonctions de k telles que

$$\Sigma \left[\frac{d^2x}{dk dh} \frac{d\Theta}{dx} + \frac{dx}{dk} \frac{d\Theta}{dh} \frac{d^2\Theta}{dx dh} \right] = 0,$$

$$\Sigma \left[\frac{d^2x}{dk dl} \frac{d\Theta}{dx} + \frac{dx}{dk} \frac{d\Theta}{dl} \frac{d^2\Theta}{dx dl} \right] = 0,$$

$$\Sigma \left[\frac{d^2x}{dl dh} \frac{d\Theta}{dx} + \frac{dx}{dh} \frac{d\Theta}{dl} \frac{d^2\Theta}{dx dh} \right] = 0,$$

et que, de plus,

$$\frac{dx}{dk} \frac{dx}{dh} \frac{dx}{dl} = 0$$

en éliminant k, l , on a, entre x, y, z l'équation $V = 0$ d'une surface. Je dis que les équations $k = \text{const.}, l = \text{const.}$, déterminent les deux systèmes des courbes de courbure de cette surface, et que, de plus, mais que cette surface est divisible en carrés par ses courbes de courbure.

En effet, les équations donnent

$$\Theta \left[\left(\frac{dx}{dk} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dy}{dk} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dz}{dk} \right)^2 \right] - dl \left[\left(\frac{dx}{dl} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dy}{dl} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dz}{dl} \right)^2 \right] = 0,$$

ou qui implique

$$\left(\frac{dx}{dk} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dy}{dk} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dz}{dk} \right)^2 = \Theta K,$$

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où H est fonction de k et seulement ; et la même de même

$$\left(\frac{dx}{dl}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dy}{dl}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dz}{dl}\right)^2 = \Theta L,$$

où K est fonction de l et seulement ; donc, en dérivant, comme à l'ordinaire,

$$dx^2 + dy^2 + dz^2 = E dk^2 + 2F dk dl + G dl^2,$$

on aura bien voir le théorème énoncé que la surface est divisible en carrés par les courbes de courbure.

Les équations donnent aussi

$$\frac{dx}{dk} \frac{dy}{dl} : \frac{dy}{dk} \frac{dz}{dl} : \frac{dz}{dk} \frac{dx}{dl} = 0;$$

où, cela étant, l'équation différentielle des courbes de courbure se réduit, comme je viens le montrer, à $dk dl = 0$; on a donc les équations des courbes de courbure de la surface.

Pour cela, en considérant x, y, z comme des fonctions données de k, l , j'écris, comme à l'ordinaire,

$$\frac{dx}{dk} = a, \quad \frac{dy}{dk} = b, \quad \frac{dz}{dk} = c, \quad \frac{dx}{dl} = a', \quad \frac{dy}{dl} = b', \quad \frac{dz}{dl} = c',$$

et de même $b, b', c, c', a', a', c', b', c'$, pour les coefficients différentiels du second ordre de y et z respectivement. J'écris aussi

$$A = bc' - bc, \quad B = ca' - c'a, \quad C = ab' - a'b,$$

$$E = a^2 + a'^2 + a''^2, \quad F = aa' + bb' + cc', \quad G = a'^2 + b'^2 + c'^2.$$

L'équation différentielle des courbes de courbure est

$$\begin{vmatrix} dx, & dy, & dz \\ A, & B, & C \\ dA, & dB, & dC \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

Le premier terme de ce déterminant est $dx(BdC - C dB)$, savoir

$$(adk + a' dl) [B(c, dk + c' dl) - x(b, dk + b' dl) - C(bdk + b' dl) - C(b' dk + b'' dl)] \\ - C[(c, dk + c' dl) - C(bdk + b' dl) - x(bdk + b' dl) - C(b' dk + b'' dl)]$$

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ce qui se réduit de suite à

$$(adk + a' dl) [B(c dk + c' dl) - C(b dk + b' dl)] - v [a(c dk + b dl) - C(c' dk + b' dl)] \\ - [a(c dk + b dl) - C'(c' dk + b' dl)] - v [a(c dk + b dl) - C(c' dk + b' dl)] dk;$$

en formant des expressions analogues du second et du troisième terme, et en prenant la somme, l'équation différentielle devient

$$[BAa + Ba'b + Cc' - Ca'b]dk - F(Aa' + Ba'b + Cc' + Ca')dl \\ + [BAA' + Bb'B' + Cc']dk - G(Aa' + Ba'b + Cc')dl \\ + [F(Aa'' + Bb''B' + Cc'' - GA(Aa' + Bb' + Cc'))]dk \\ + [F'(Aa'' + B'b'' + C'c'') - G'(Aa' + B'b'' + C'c')]dl = 0;$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose

$$\begin{vmatrix} dk, & -dl, & 0 \\ E, & F, & G \\ Aa, & Bb, & Cc \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

en éditant si nous écrivons en cours une équation différentielle d'une édaire fraction quand ne contient ne soumet et z , z , ou z deux de la surface ainsi seulement une fraction des para- mètres k, l .

En supposant $F = 0$, l'équation se réduit à

$$(Aa' + Ba'b + Cc')(Aa' dk + Cc' dl) = 0 \\ + (Aa' dk + Bb' dl + Cc' dl)(Aa' + Bb' + Cc')dk dl = 0;$$

mais ainsi simplement le réduire l'équation se réduit simplement à $dk dl = 0$.

En supposant $Aa + Bb + Cc = 0$, l'équation se réduit simplement à

$$Aa' dk + Bb' dl + Cc' dl = 0,$$

mais cette équation $Aa da + Bb db + Cc dc = 0$; en réduit simplement à $dk dl = 0$.

$$\begin{vmatrix} a, & b, & c \\ a', & b', & c' \\ a'', & b'', & c'' \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

ou

$$\begin{vmatrix} \frac{dx}{dk}, & \frac{dy}{dk}, & \frac{dz}{dk} \\ \frac{dx}{dl}, & \frac{dy}{dl}, & \frac{dz}{dl} \\ \frac{d^2x}{dk dl}, & \frac{d^2y}{dk dl}, & \frac{d^2z}{dk dl} \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

et ainsi $F = 0$, satisfaisant dans le même la même on avons avec dans $dk dl = 0$ comme équation différentielle des courbes de courbure.

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DE COURBURE ET SUR LA THÉORIE DE DUPIN.

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On vérifie sans peine les équations fondamentales, en prenant $\Omega = \lambda - k$,

$$-(z - z_0)(x - x_0) + a(x + b)(x + b_0) + c_0,$$

$$-(z - z_0)(y - y_0) + a(y + b)(y + b_0) + c_0,$$

$$-(z - z_0)(z - z_0) + a(z + b)(z + b_0) + c_0,$$

où qui donne les courbes de courbure de l'ellipsoïde $\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} = 1$. L'ellipsoïde, comme on sait, sera coupé d'ailleurs de cercles de carrés par des courbes de courbure; mais je n'ai pas encore décrit d'autres solutions.

Je remarque que l'équation peut être écrite sous la forme

$$\frac{d}{dz} \left(\frac{1}{\Omega} \frac{d\sigma}{dx} \right) + \frac{d}{dx} \left(\frac{1}{\Omega} \frac{d\sigma}{dz} \right) = 0;$$

donc, en écrivant

$$\frac{d\sigma}{dx} = \Omega \frac{d\sigma_1}{dx}, \quad \frac{d\sigma}{dz} = -\Omega \frac{d\sigma_1}{dz},$$

on trouve

$$\frac{d\sigma}{dx} = \Omega \frac{d\sigma_1}{dz}, \quad \frac{d\sigma}{dz} = -\Omega \frac{d\sigma_1}{dx},$$

ce qui donne

$$\frac{d}{dz} \left(\Omega \frac{d\sigma_1}{dx} \right) + \frac{d}{dx} \left(\Omega \frac{d\sigma_1}{dz} \right) = 0,$$

équation de Ω de la même forme que celle pour σ .

On débute une démonstration très-simple du théorème de Dupin. En considérant comme argument (x, y, z) comme des fonctions données de (λ, k, l) , le point (x, y, z) sera situé sur une surface, et les conditions pour que les courbes de courbure soient $k = \text{const.}$, $l = \text{const.}$ seront

$$\begin{vmatrix} \frac{dx}{d\lambda}, & \frac{dx}{dk}, & \frac{dx}{dl} \\ \frac{dy}{d\lambda}, & \frac{dy}{dk}, & \frac{dy}{dl} \\ \frac{dz}{d\lambda}, & \frac{dz}{dk}, & \frac{dz}{dl} \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

Cela étant, en introduisant un troisième paramètre λ comme fonction de (k, l) ou de (x, y, z) , ou réciproquement, (x, y, z) des fonctions données de (λ, k, l) . On

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a ici les trois systèmes de surfaces $\lambda = \text{const.}$, $k = \text{const.}$, $l = \text{const.}$, et les conditions pour que ces surfaces se coupent orthogonalement peuvent s'écrire sous la forme

$$\frac{dx}{d\lambda} \frac{dx}{dk} + \frac{dy}{d\lambda} \frac{dy}{dk} + \frac{dz}{d\lambda} \frac{dz}{dk} = 0,$$

$$\frac{dx}{dk} \frac{dx}{dl} + \frac{dy}{dk} \frac{dy}{dl} + \frac{dz}{dk} \frac{dz}{dl} = 0,$$

$$\frac{dx}{dl} \frac{dx}{d\lambda} + \frac{dy}{dl} \frac{dy}{d\lambda} + \frac{dz}{dl} \frac{dz}{d\lambda} = 0.$$

On a donc

$$\frac{dx}{d\lambda} : \frac{dy}{d\lambda} : \frac{dz}{d\lambda} = \frac{dy}{dk} \frac{dz}{dl} - \frac{dz}{dk} \frac{dy}{dl} : \frac{dz}{dk} \frac{dx}{dl} - \frac{dx}{dk} \frac{dz}{dl} : \frac{dx}{dk} \frac{dy}{dl} - \frac{dy}{dk} \frac{dx}{dl}.$$

Pour abréger, j'écris

$$\frac{dx}{d\lambda} \frac{dx}{dk} + \frac{dy}{d\lambda} \frac{dy}{dk} + \frac{dz}{d\lambda} \frac{dz}{dk} = [\lambda, k] \dots,$$

et de même

$$\frac{dx}{d\lambda} \frac{dx}{d\lambda} + \frac{dy}{d\lambda} \frac{dy}{d\lambda} + \frac{dz}{d\lambda} \frac{dz}{d\lambda} = [\lambda, \lambda] \dots$$

Les conditions données sont ainsi

$$[l, l] = 0, \quad [l, k] = 0, \quad [\lambda, k] = 0;$$

en différentiant ces équations par rapport à λ , k , l respectivement, on obtient

$$[k, l, l] = 0, \quad [l, k, l] = 0,$$

$$[l, l, k] = 0, \quad [\lambda, k, l] = 0,$$

$$[\lambda, k, l] = 0, \quad [k, \lambda, l] = 0;$$

donc

$$[\lambda, k, l] = 0, \quad [\lambda, l, k] = 0, \quad [l, \lambda, k] = 0.$$

Mais l'équation $[\lambda, k] = 0$ et l'équation $[l, \lambda, k] = 0$, en substituant dans celle-ci les valeurs de $\frac{dx}{d\lambda}$, $\frac{dy}{d\lambda}$, $\frac{dz}{d\lambda}$, sont parfaitement les conditions pour que la surface $l = \text{const.}$ soit coupée par les autres surfaces selon ses courbes de courbure : c'est le théorème.

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**SUR LA CONDITION POUR QU'UNE FAMILLE DE SURFACES DONNÉES
PUISSE FAIRE PARTIE D'UN SYSTÈME ORTHOGONAL.**

[From the *Comptes Rendus de l'Académie des Sciences de Paris*, tom. LXXV.
(Juillet—Décembre, 1872), pp. 177—185, 246—250, 324—330, 381—385, 1800—1803.]

[Pp. 177—185.]

1. SOIT $\rho = f(x, y, z)$ l'équation d'une famille de surfaces qui fait partie d'un système orthogonal. On sait que ρ satisfait à une équation à différences partielles du troisième ordre, et en suivant le même rapport de M. Levy, dans son excellent "Mémoire sur les coordonnées curvilignes orthogonales" (*Journal de l'École Polytechnique*, t. XXVI., pp. 157—200, 1870), je suis parvenu à former cette équation.

2. Je remarque que la théorème fondamental de M. Levy est, en effet, assez élégant. Considérons une surface de la famille ρ soit P un point quelconque de cette surface, et PT , PT_1 les normales et les tangentes aux deux courbes de courbure au point P . Donc, suivant la notion ordinaire pour P la surface considérée ρ doit être normale à PT , et les tangentes à forment, avec une normale à la surface, un système orthogonal de tangentes; mais nous pouvons considérer les autres courbes de courbure de la surface ρ . Donc PT_1 et PT'_1 se rencontrent; ils se rencontrent supposé en la surface de la famille ρ . Et plus, la découplant la surface f et la surface f_1 de la nature ρ , en à l'instant les deux conditions se rencontrent au même point. viz. Réciproquement, si PT_1 , PT'_1 se rencontrent (ou ce qui revient au même : si les surfaces f , PT'_1) la famille ρ fera partie d'un système orthogonal; ce qui est le théorème de M. Levy.

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3. Soient (X, Y, Z) les fonctions dérivées de ρ du premier ordre ; (a, b, c, f, g, h) celles du second ordre ; $(a, b, c, f, g, h, i, j, k, l)$ celles du troisième ordre, savoir

$$(X, Y, Z) = \frac{d\rho}{dx}, \frac{d\rho}{dy}, \frac{d\rho}{dz},$$

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h) = \frac{d^2\rho}{dx^2}, \frac{d^2\rho}{dy^2}, \frac{d^2\rho}{dz^2}, \frac{d^2\rho}{dy\,dz}, \frac{d^2\rho}{dz\,dx}, \frac{d^2\rho}{dx\,dy},$$

$$(a_1, b_1, c_1, f_1, g_1, h_1, i_1, j_1, k_1, l_1) = \frac{d^3\rho}{dx^3}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dy^3}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dz^3}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dy^2\,dz}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dy\,dz^2}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dz^2\,dx}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dz\,dx^2}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dx^2\,dy}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dx\,dy^2}, \frac{d^3\rho}{dx\,dy\,dz};$$

soient de plus

$$\begin{aligned} A &= 2(Zh - Yg), & F &= X(c - b) + Yh - Zg, \\ B &= 2(Xf - Zh), & G &= Y(a - c) + Zf - Xh, \\ C &= 2(Yg - Xf), & H &= Z(b - a) + Xg - Yf, \end{aligned}$$

valeurs qui satisfont aux équations

$$A + B + C = 0 \quad \text{et} \quad A, B, C, F, G, H)(X, Y, Z) = 0.$$

Alors les tangentes PT , PT_1 sont données par les équations

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^2 = 0,$$

$$X\alpha + Y\beta + Z\gamma = 0.$$

et en partant de ces équations, mais en supposant que pour le point P les valeurs de X, Y soient $X = 0, Y = 0$, M. Levy obtient comme conditions de l'intersection donés il s'agit

$$\left(a \frac{dX}{dx} + b \frac{dY}{dy} - h \frac{dX}{dy} + j \frac{dY}{dx} \right) Z = 0,$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$\{2g(a - b) + 2h(a - b)Z = -2(jX - jY)Z + 2(hX - bY) - 4h = 0,$$

savoir : cette équation est en une dérivant l'équation cherchée du troisième ordre en ρ écrivant $X = 0, Y = 0$.

4. Je passe à la recherche de l'équation générale ; pour ceci (X, Y, Z) désirant comme argument, nous pouvons considérer aux quantités données du second ordre (f, g, h) (et de même du troisième ordre a_1 , etc.). Cette équation est symétrique par rapport à X, Y, Z , la coordonnée étant pour le point au choix ; donc PT , etc., X, Y mais nous donnerons un système de coordonnées de un manière ; le symétrie est ainsi de coordonnées ; et celles de (X, Y, Z) et (α, β, γ) doivent être les valeurs de (x, y, z) , mais données par les équations

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^2 = 0,$$

$$X\alpha + Y\beta + Z\gamma = 0.$$

Ces équations impliquent $XX_1 + YY_1 + ZZ_1 = 0$, et en se rappelant à une équation déjà mentionnée, ou à la quatrième

$$(A_1, \dots, X)(X_1, Y_1, Z_1)^2 = 0,$$

$$(A_2, \dots, X)(X_2, Y_2, Z_2)^2 = 0,$$

$$(A_3, \dots, X)(X_3, Y_3, Z_3)^2 = 0,$$

$$X_1X_2 + Y_1Y_2 + Z_1Z_2 = 0,$$

$$XX_1 + YY_1 + ZZ_1 = 0, \quad XX_2 + YY_2 + ZZ_2 = 0.$$

L'origine étant quelconque, prenons (x, y, z) pour coordonnées du P ; et $\alpha + \beta + \gamma$ les coordonnées du P' ; nous avons les $d\rho$: $d\rho = X : X_1$, et comme X a reçu un signe qui doit s'unir aux symboles, nous pouvons exemple un facteur infinitésimal commun, et l'on supposera $d\rho = (X, Y, Z)$ et derrière en α , on pourrait, P à un point P' , ces valeurs $d\rho = X_1$, etc. Au lieu de (X_1, Y_1, Z_1) nous emploierons qu'une fonction quelconque à (α, β, γ) devient $\alpha + d\alpha$, ou passant du point P et point P' , la valeur correspondante sera à $X \frac{d\Phi}{dx} + Y \frac{d\Phi}{dy} + Z \frac{d\Phi}{dz}$, ou, en écrivant

$$\delta = X \frac{d}{dx} + Y \frac{d}{dy} + Z \frac{d}{dz},$$

ce sera $\delta\Phi$. Cela étant, et nous avons remarqué que ξ, η, ζ pour coordonnées courantes, et θ pour un paramètre arbitraire, les équations de PT seront

$$\xi = x + \theta X_1, \quad \eta = y + \theta Y_1, \quad \zeta = z + \theta Z_1;$$

et si cette droite rencontre PT_1 , alors on suppose θ, η, ζ pour les coordonnées du point d'intersection, nous aurons $0 = \xi + X\delta\theta + \theta\delta X_1, \dots$, ou en éliminant $\delta\theta$ il vient

$$0 = \begin{vmatrix} X_1 & X_2 & X\delta X_1 \\ b_1 & Y_2 & Y\delta Y_1 \\ b_1 & Z_2 & Z\delta Z_1 \end{vmatrix},$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$0 = \begin{vmatrix} X_1 & X_2 & \delta X_1 \\ Y_1 & Y_2 & \delta Y_1 \\ Z_1 & Z_2 & \delta Z_1 \end{vmatrix}.$$

Mais nous avons $X_2 : Y_2 : Z_2 = YZ_1 - ZY_1 : ZX_1 - XZ_1 : XY_1 - YX_1$; donc cette équation devient $X_1\delta X_1 + Y_1\delta Y_1 + Z_1\delta Z_1 = 0$, ou bien encore $\delta(X_1^2 + Y_1^2 + Z_1^2) = 0$. L'équation trouvée peut donc s'écrire dans la forme plus simplifiée

$$X\delta X_1 + Y\delta Y_1 + Z\delta Z_1 = 0,$$

équation qui exprime la condition pour l'intersection des tangentes PT_1, PT'_1 ou PT_1, PT''_1 .

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6. Dans la démonstration précédente, je me suis servi du théorème de Dupin ; mais il convient de remarquer qu'on peut arriver aux équations orthogonales et donner par $X, Y, Z ; X_1, Y_1, Z_1 ; X_2, Y_2, Z_2$, des liaisons en ρ , respectivement, il serait possible de déduire cette équation suivante :

$$XX_1 + YY_1 + ZZ_1 = 0,$$

$$XX_2 + YY_2 + ZZ_2 = 0,$$

$$X_1X_2 + Y_1Y_2 + Z_1Z_2 = 0.$$

En effet, l'équation tirée directement de cette manière par M. L. Ellis, dans une démonstration du théorème de Dupin, publiée dans *l'ouvrage de Gregory (Examples of the processes of the differential and integral calculus ; Cambridge, 1841)*. Les premières trois équations donnent $X : Y : Z = Y_1Z_2 - Z_1Y_2 : Z_1X_2 - X_1Z_2 : X_1Y_2 - Y_1X_2$, ou en deux de l'expression

$$(YZ_1 - YZ_1)(\delta a_1) + (X_1Z - ZX_1)(\delta a_2) + \dots = 0,$$

intégrale par un facteur ; on qui donne

$$(YZ_1 - YZ_1) \left[\frac{dX_1}{dx} \delta X - X \delta X_1 \right] + \frac{dx}{dx_1} (ZX_1 - X_1Z) (\delta X_2 \delta x \dots) = 0.$$

Le terme en $\square$ est égal à $-\delta(YZ_1 - YZ_1)$, ainsi

$$\left(X_1 \frac{dX_1}{dx} + Y_1 \frac{dY_1}{dy} + Z_1 \frac{dZ_1}{dz} \right) \delta X - \left(X \frac{dX_2}{dx} + Y \frac{dY_2}{dy} + Z \frac{dZ_2}{dz} \right) \delta X_1 - X_1 \left(\frac{dX_1}{dx} \delta X + \frac{dX_1}{dy} \delta Y + \frac{dX_1}{dz} \delta Z \right) - \dots =$$

et la somme qui correspond à la deuxième ligne de cette expression s'évanouit évidemment ; la première ligne peut s'écrire sous la forme $\delta_1 \delta_2 = \delta_2 \delta_1$, donc, en éliminant X, Y, Z et X_1, Y_1, Z_1 la condition devient simplement

$$X(\delta_1 X_2 - \delta_2 X_1) + Y(\delta_1 Y_2 - \delta_2 Y_1) + Z(\delta_1 Z_2 - \delta_2 Z_1) = 0.$$

Mais nous avons

$$\delta_1 \delta_2 \frac{dX}{dx} = X_1 \left(X_2 \frac{d^2 X}{dx^2} + Y_2 \frac{d^2 X}{dx dy} + Z_2 \frac{d^2 X}{dx dz} \right) + \dots = X_1 X_2 a + Y_1 Y_2 b + Z_1 Z_2 c + (Y_1 Z_2 + Z_1 Y_2) f + \dots,$$

et ainsi $\delta_1 X_2 = \delta_2 X_1$ et $(Y_1 Z_2 - Z_1 Y_2) f$, $(Z_1 Y_2 - Y_1 Z_2) g$, $(X_1 Y_2 - Y_1 X_2) h$, ou de même $\delta_1 Y_2 = \delta_2 Y_1$ et $X_1 Y_2 - X_2 Y_1$, etc. ; on a donc

$$\delta_1 X_2 - \delta_2 X_1 = X(Y_1 Z_2 + Y_2 Z_1) - 2Z(X_1 Y_2 + Y_1 X_2), \dots,$$

ou à la quatrième

$$XX_1 X_2 a + YY_1 Y_2 b + ZZ_1 Z_2 c + YY_1 Z_2 + YY_2 Z_1 = 0;$$

et ainsi l'équation dont il s'agit

$$XX_1 + YY_1 + ZZ_1, + (XX_2 + YY_2 + ZZ_2) = 0.$$

On se servait ces suggestions géométriques de cette équation.

7. Dans la question actuelle, partant de cette équation, je rappelle que les valeurs de X, Y, Z, X_1, Y_1, Z_1 sont, comme celles de (α, β, γ) données par les équations

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^2 = 0, \quad X\alpha + Y\beta + Z\gamma = 0,$$

en supposant que ces équations sont :

$$X_2 : Y_2 : Z_2 = X' : Y' : Z' = Y''Z' - Z''Y' : Z''X' - X''Z' : X''Y' - Y''X';$$

la condition devient

$$X_2\delta X + Y_2\delta Y + Z_2\delta Z = 0, \quad X\delta + Y\delta + Z\delta = 0.$$

8. Pour effectuer la réduction de cette formule, nous avons besoin de plusieurs formules subsidiaires. J'écris

$$\begin{aligned} (BC - F^2, GH - AF, HF - BG, GF - BC, HF - CG, FG - AH)(X, Y, Z)^2 \\ = (\mathfrak{A}, \mathfrak{B}, \mathfrak{C}, \mathfrak{F}, \mathfrak{G}, \mathfrak{H})(X, Y, Z)^2 = \omega, \end{aligned}$$

et je deduis par $(a), (b), (c), (f), (g), (h)$ les coefficients de $\lambda^*, \dots$ dans la fonction

$$\begin{aligned} (A, B, C, F, G, H)(\lambda X + \mu, \lambda Y + \nu, \lambda Z + \xi)^2 = \mu^2\mathfrak{A} - 2\mu\nu\mathfrak{B} - \lambda^2\mathfrak{F}, \dots, \\ -2\{(B, X, X, h)(X, Y, Z)\lambda\mu + \dots\} - 2(C, Y, Y, h)(X, Y, Z)\lambda\nu + \dots, \end{aligned}$$

et je donne par $(a), (b), (c), (f), (g), (h)$ les valeurs de $\lambda^*, \dots$, dans la fonction

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)(X, X', X'')^2 = \mu^2, \quad 2YZ' = \alpha, \quad 2ZX' = \beta, \quad 2XY' = h :$$

$$\begin{aligned} (a) &= bZ^2 + cY^2 - 2fYZ, \\ (b) &= cX^2 + aZ^2 - 2gZX, \\ (c) &= aY^2 + bX^2 - 2hXY, \\ (f) &= -aYZ - fX^2 + gXY + hXZ, \\ (g) &= -bZX - gY^2 + fXY + hYZ, \\ (h) &= -cXY - hZ^2 + fXZ + gYZ; \end{aligned}$$

et je remarque qu'on vérifie les équations

$$(a) + (b) + (c) = 0,$$

ainsi que

$$\begin{aligned} (a)X + (h)Y + (g)Z &= 0, \\ (h)X + (b)Y + (f)Z &= 0, \\ (g)X + (f)Y + (c)Z &= 0. \end{aligned}$$

Cela étant, nous avons les identités

$$\begin{aligned} \{(a), (b), (c)\}(X, Y, Z) &= 0, \\ \{(b), (c), (a)\}(Y, Z, X) &= 0, \\ \{(g), (h), (f)\}(Z, X, Y) &= 0, \\ \{(B(b) - (D)(p) - (g)(g) + (A)(h) - (h)(h)\}(2) &= (b)(C) - (c)(B) - (h)(g) + (g)(h). \end{aligned}$$

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savoir, $(h)(c) - (f) = X\omega, \dots$ De plus

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)((g), (h), (f))^2 = 2X(YZ' - ZY')(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)\phi,$$

$$(B, B, F)((a), (b), (h))^2 = 4(YZ' - ZY')(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)\phi,$$

$$(G, H)((g), (h), (f))((a), (h), (g)) = -2(Y^2)(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)\phi,$$

où

$$\phi = aBC + bCA + cAB - 2(fFA + gFB + hHC) + 2(AGH + BHF + CFG).$$

Multipliant cette dernière fonction par l'un quelconque des coefficients $(a), \dots$, et substituant, en éliminant ses équations; mais je dirai seulement celles qui ne sont du (g) , savoir, nous avons

$$(g)\left\{A\omega + B(b) + C(c) + 2F(f) + 2G(g) + 2H(h)\right\} \\ + 2\phi[-XBE + YZY + GTY + HXZ] = 0,$$

ici la seconde ligne est égale à

$$BY[(b)X + (a)Y - 2fXY + 2gXY + 2hXY] = 0,$$

et l'équation finale est

$$ZX(\mathfrak{B}) + (B)(g)(\omega - (h)) = (YX - X')(-X(3) + 4(2 + Y + Z')\phi),$$

ou, en remarquant que

$$\begin{aligned} (\mathfrak{B})(g) - (3)(b) &= ZY, \\ (\mathfrak{B})(h) - (3)(c) &= XZ, \\ (\mathfrak{B})(f) - (3)(a) &= -YZ, \\ (\mathfrak{B})(f) - (3)(g) &= X^2, \end{aligned}$$

c'est-à-dire

$$(g)(YZ\omega + YY')(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)\phi.$$

9. Je reviens à la question principale, à savoir, on se servira des équations arbitraires qui ouvriront les besoins de cinq compagnies. Il n'y a pas d'expression système pour la valeur de $X_1 : Y_1 : Z_1$ pour les $X_2 : Y_2 : Z_2$, et nous trouvons

$$X_1 : Y_1 : Z_1 = (a), (b) : (c) : (h) - X\sqrt{\omega} : (g) - Y\sqrt{\omega},$$

$$X_2 : Y_2 : Z_2 = (a), (b) : (c) : (h) - X\sqrt{\omega} : (g) - Y\sqrt{\omega},$$

et la condition dérive

$$\{(b)Z - (c)Y\}^2 + \{(c)X - (a)Z\}^2 + \{(a)Y - (b)X\}^2 + \{(h)X - (g)Z\}^2 - \omega = 0,$$

ou, puisque $X\sqrt{\omega} = \frac{(\mathfrak{B})}{X}\omega = (\omega)$, on a

$$\Sigma(\delta(\mathfrak{B} - X(g) - (b)X)(g) - (a)Y) = 0.$$

équation qui contient, comme une le voudra, le facteur ω ; en l'enlevant, elle restera au facteur, l'équation deviendra symétrique.

J'écris

$$\Delta(g) = \Delta(g) + \Sigma(g), \quad \Sigma(b) = \Delta(b) + \Sigma(b), \quad \delta\phi = \Delta\phi + \Sigma\phi,$$

en dénotant par Δ les parties qui dépendent de δX , δY , δZ , et par Σ' celles qui dépendent de $\delta a, \dots$. Les fonctions Δ doivent en avoir le facteur $\omega = X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2$.

$$\begin{aligned} \Omega = & ((b)Z - (c)Y)\{\Delta(b)Z - \Delta(c)Y - (c)\Delta Z + (b)\Delta Z\} \\ & + ((c)X - (a)Z)\{\Delta(c)X - \Delta(a)Z + (c)\Delta X - (a)\Delta Z\} \\ & + ((a)Y - (b)X)\{\Delta(a)Y - \Delta(b)X + (a)\Delta Y - (b)\Delta X\} \\ & + ((h)X - (g)Z)\{\Delta(h)X - \Delta(g)Z + (h)\Delta X - (g)\Delta Z\}, \end{aligned}$$

et ainsi l'expression entiere se mettra à

$$\frac{1}{2}\delta((b)Z - (c)Y)^2 + \frac{1}{2}\delta((c)X - (a)Z)^2 + \frac{1}{2}\delta((a)Y - (b)X)^2 + \frac{1}{2}\delta((h)X - (g)Z)^2.$$

10. Je calcule l'expression de Ω_1 . Nous avons

$$\Delta\Omega = \Delta\{-CY + FB\}\Delta X + (-CX + GA)\Delta Y + (FX + GY)\Delta Z + \Sigma F\Delta(YZ + ZY')(XZ dY + ZY dX);$$

$$\Delta\phi = (BC - F^2)\Delta X + (FH - AF)\Delta Y + (HF - BG)\Delta Z + ()\Delta a + ()\Delta b + ()\Delta c;$$

ou la dernière ligne est égale à

$$\begin{aligned} & \{(g)Y - (h)Z\}\Delta a + \omega\delta a + \omega\delta(b) - (a)Z\{\Delta b + (b)\delta X + (g)\delta Z\}\Delta c \\ & + \{(\omega Z + (h)Z)\Delta f + ((h)Z - (b)Z)\Delta g + (b)Z\Delta h, \end{aligned}$$

où la seconde ligne est égale à

$$-(a)Z(R, F)\{\Delta a + (b)\delta Y + (g)\delta Z\}\Delta b,$$

et ainsi l'expression entiere se mettra à

$$(\Omega) - (R - F)\Delta b + F\{((h)\Delta b + (g) - (b)\Delta b) - 0 = (\Omega\mathfrak{A})\Delta b.$$

c'est-à-dire le coefficient de Δb est

$$[-AAX + F(YZ' + Z(g))X + 2((F)\delta b + 2(b))X + 2(B)(b)X + 2(b)\delta Z + 2\mathfrak{A}],$$

ou la dernière ligne est égale à

$$-(R - F)\Delta b + F\{(h)\Delta b + (g) - (b)\Delta b\} - 0 = (\Omega\mathfrak{A})\Delta b.$$

Le coefficient de ΔY est

$$[-AXX + F(YZ' + Z(h))X + 2((F)\delta b + 2(b))X + 2(B)(b)X + 2(b)\delta Z + 2\mathfrak{A}],$$

où la deuxième ligne est égale à

$$-(a)X(F, B, F)(\delta X, Y, Z(f)) = (\Omega\mathfrak{A})\Delta X;$$

et ainsi l'expression entiere se mettra à

$$(\omega) - (h - X)\Delta b + F\{((h)Y\delta Z - (g)Z\delta X\} - 0 = (\Omega\mathfrak{A})\Delta b.$$

c'est-à-dire

$$-\phi(A, X - B)XE + FEX + GP + HVT = 0.$$

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ou l'expression entière est ainsi égale à

$$\begin{aligned} & \{A - B\}\delta\{(b) - (h)\}(g) + F\{(g)(g) - (c)(h) - (c)(b)(g) - (h)\} \\ & + H\{(g)(h) - (a)(f)\}(g), F\}(b), (h), (k) - HJ\{(\omega), F + HJ\} \\ & + (h)(g)\{F, G\}(\omega), F\}. \end{aligned}$$

c'est-à-dire

$$A\{B(b) - (h)Y\}(g) - B(b)(h)(g) - C(c)(c)(h) + F(c)(c)(b) - F(b)(c)(g) - H(\omega)(b),$$

ou enâ

$$A - (h)\{g(b)Y - F\}(b)(g) + F(c)(c)(b) - F(b)(c)(g) - H(\omega)(b),$$

enâ réduisant aux moyens de $(a) + (b) + (c) = 0$ et $A + B + C = 0$, le coefficient de δY devient

$$\begin{aligned} & -(\omega)((b) - F)(g) + (B(c) - 2F)(g)(c) + (g)(c)(c)(g) - F(g)(b)(c) \\ & + (h(c) - F)\{-F\}(\omega), F\} + \{(b) - 2F\}(g)(b) + H\{(\omega)(c) - F\}(b), \end{aligned}$$

ou, de même, le coefficient de δZ est

$$-(\omega)\{-(\omega)(c) - F(g) + F(g)(c)\}(b);$$

ce qui achève le calcul de Ω_1 .

[Pp. 246—250.]

11. Pour trouver Ω_2 , nous avons

$$\begin{aligned} \delta(g) &= -X(b)\delta a + Y(c)\delta b + Y(\delta Z), \\ \delta(b) &= X(b)\delta a + Y(c)\delta b - Y\delta b, \\ \delta(c) &= -X(c)\delta a - Y(c)\delta b - Y\delta(c)(c)(c) - X\delta b\}(c)(c). \end{aligned}$$

et de là

$$\delta_1 = -XY\delta f + XZ\delta g + ZXY^2\delta b + 2(g)Y\delta Z\delta + Z\delta b,$$

ou qui n'est de la nature de Ω_2 . Dans les expressions de Ω_1 , on doit substituer ces valeurs

[Pp. 246—250.]

Les premières deux lignes en réduisent fadement à

$$\omega\{-XX + YY + Z(c)(h)(b) - 2X(c) - Y(g)(h)\}(b) - \omega\},$$

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et la troisième ligne à $2(b)\{Z(g) - X(c)\}\delta b$. Donc l'expression entière contient le facteur (b) , et nous avons

$$\begin{aligned}\Omega_1 = & (a) \cdot \omega - [X(c) + Z(b)]\{(b)Y - 2(b)\} \\ & + \{Y(b)(g) - 2(g)\delta + Z(b)X\delta(b) \\ & + 2(Xg - X\delta b + 2(g)\delta X \\ & + 2(Y - (c)\delta(b)X(b) + 2(c)X\delta(b),\end{aligned}$$

expression qui se réduit sans peine à la forme symétrique sous laquelle je la présente ici, savoir

12. Cette équation est, $\Omega_1 + \Omega_2 = 0$; savoir, en mettant la facteur (ω) , nous avons

$$\begin{aligned}\frac{1}{2}\{ & F\{(b-c) - (c)\delta(b-c)(b) - (g-b) + (c)\delta(c) \\ & + \{G\{(b) - (c)\delta(b) - (c)\delta(b-g)\}\} \\ & + \{H\{(b)(c) - (c)(c) - (c)(c)(g-h)\}\} \\ & + \{B(c)(b) - (c)(c)\delta(c) + (c)\delta(c)\} \\ & + \{C(c)(b)(c) - (c) + F(c)\delta(b)(c) - 2X(g)\}\} \\ & - X(b-c) - (b-c)\delta(b)(c) + 2X(g)\}\} \\ & + 2X(b) - (g) - (b)(c) + (c)\delta(b)(c)\}\} \\ & - 2(c)\delta(b)(c) + (b)\delta(b)\}(c) - \omega, \\ & - 2\omega(c) + Y\delta(c) - X\delta(b) - Z\delta(b)\delta(h) \\ & + 2X\delta(g)(c) + (c)\delta(b)(c) - Z\delta(b) \\ & + 2X\delta(g)(c) - 2Y\delta(b)\delta(h).\end{aligned}$$

On se rappelle que $\delta = X \frac{d}{dx} + Y \frac{d}{dy} + Z \frac{d}{dz}$, et

$$\Sigma \frac{d}{dx} + Y \frac{d}{dy} + Z \frac{d}{dz}.$$

13. Pour rester de la résultat de M. Levy, j'écrirai d'abord $X = 0, Y = 0$, nous avons alors

$$(a), (b), (c), (f), (g), (h) = -2hZ^2, Z(c-b), 0, -HZ, gZ, 0;$$

et l'équation devient

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)(\delta b, \delta a, 0, 0, 0, 0, \delta f, \delta g, \delta h) - BCb + GHZ - GHZ = 0,$$

$= -BCb + GHZ - GHZ = 0$, mais $A = -BC$; et l'équation devient

$$2\{X(a-b) + 2hC - q(c-b)\delta z + 2(c-b)Z\delta hg - 4hZ\delta Z + 2gZ\delta Z = 0.$$

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Mais nous avons $\delta X = gZ$, $\delta Y = -hZ$, $\delta a = \delta b$, etc., on plus,

$$\delta x = h\delta - g\delta Y = 2\{X(c-b) + h(c-b)\} = 2g^2(c-b) + h^2(b-a) - 2gh :$$

$$\delta y = -2h\delta + g\delta Y = 2\{X(b-a) + h(b-a)\} = 2g^2(b-a) + h^2(a-c) - 2gh :$$

$$\delta x = -2(a-b) + h(a-b)\} = 2g^2(b-a) + h^2(a-c)Z - 2gh :$$

$$\delta h = -2X(b-a) + h\{c-g\}\delta Z = -2g^2(a-b) + h^2(a-c)Z - 2gh :$$

ce qui s'accorde avec le résultat cité.

14. En changeant la signification de X, Y, Z , écrivons $\rho = X + Y + Z$, (X, Y, Z) dénotant à présent des fonctions de x, y, z respectivement, en dénotant par X', Y', Z' les fonctions dérivées de celles-ci, les fonctions précédemment respectivement dénotées par a, b, c , etc., X', Y', Z' et zéro. Au moyen de l'équation précédente, la condition pour que la famille $\rho = X + Y + Z$ puisse faire partie d'un système orthogonal,

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h)x = (2AXYZ, 2BXYZ + 2XYZ, 2X'Y'Z,$$

$$X' + X'(Y + 2Y),$$

$$Y' + Y'(Z + 2Z),$$

$$Z' + Z'(X + 2X);$$

nous avons aussi

$$(AX, BY, CY) = (X', Y', Z'),$$

$$(AA, BB, CC) = (0, 0, 0),$$

$$(GF, RG, AH) = (X' - X)(\delta - X(X)) = X(X'') = -Z'(X'') = -X(Y'') = X(Y') = -X'(Y''),$$

$$Y'' - Y' = -X(Y'') = -X(Y'').$$

15. Donc, dans l'équation générale, la première ligne est

$$2[-X' \cdot 2XY'(\delta Y' - \delta Y) - 2X' \cdot 2X'(YT'' - 4X' \cdot 4X^2Y + b)]^2$$

c'est-à-dire

$$-4XY \cdot Y - XY + 2X' \cdot 4 + b$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$2XY'X''(p-2)p^2 - 2X'Y'(p-q)^2,$$

et la somme des premières trois lignes sera ainsi $2XX''$ multiplié par

$$\begin{aligned} & mp^2\{\overline{pp^2 - p^2} - 2p^2(p-q)^2 - q^2(p-q)^2 \\ & + p^2\{\overline{pp^2 - q^2} + \overline{pp^2 - 2pq}\} \\ & + q^2(p^2(p-q^2)) + (p-q)(p^2 - 2p)q\}, \end{aligned}$$

savoir dans le second facteur le coefficient de mX est $Y'\{x'(p-2)p-p\}$, et de même les termes en mX , mY , etc., respectivement, de plus, la fonction entière de $\delta\{-2Xp\}$, par respectivement, ce qui donne $-2Xp\delta$, et la somme du tout sera ainsi

$$4XX'Y'\{1'-p\} + \delta X'Y'\{(p)\}.$$

Les autres ces ne donnent pas de difficultés de même ; on a

$$\delta f = -2[X'Y'Z + Z(YT - X(p-2))]\{Y(X' - X^2) + Z(X' - X')\},$$

$$\delta g = 2[X'Y'Z(p^2 - p^2) - 2XX(p-q)^2 - 2X'Y(p^2 - 2X(p-q)^2),$$

$$\delta h = 2[Y'Y'Z(p^2 - p^2) - 2X'(p^2 - q^2) - 2X(p-q)^2(p^2 - q),$$

ou dans le second facteur le coefficient de mX , mY est $\delta\{2Y'Z - 2Z\}$, et de même pour $\delta\{-2X'Z + 2X\}$, etc. ; les coefficients de δZ , $\delta Y'$, $\delta Z'$, etc. ; ces formes ce dénotent par

$$2X'Y'\{(p-q)X' - 2p^2(Y' - Y) + (p-q)Z'\}.$$

La seconde partie est donc

$$2X'Y'Z'Y'X'\{Y' - Y' - Y'\} + (X(Z) - YX) + (Y(X) - Z(Y) - 2(YZ - X(Y))),$$

ou en réunissant les deux parties ce sera

$$2\delta Y'Y'X(p-2)p^2.$$

L'équation devient

$$\delta YX'X'\{Y' - X(Y+Z) + YX'\}^2 + YZX(Y') + ZXY'\{XY - Y\}^2,$$

savoir :

$$3(Y' - Z)X(Y - X) + (Y' - X)(Z - X) + (Y' - X)(Z'' - X)Y(YZ + (X' - Y)(Z'' - X)Y(YZ$$

équation trouvé par M. Bouquet dans son "Note sur les surfaces orthogonales" (*Journal de M. Liouville*, t. XI., pp. 446—450, 1846), et reproduite par M. Serret dans son "Mémoire sur les surfaces orthogonales" (*Journal de M. Liouville*, t. XII., pp. 241—254, 1847).

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[Pp. 324—330.]

En considérant une famille orthogonale comme une famille de surfaces qui fait partie d'un système orthogonal, on peut se proposer la question : Étant donnée une surface de la famille, trouver de la manière la plus générale la famille. J'essaye de résoudre cette question en développant les trois coordonnées selon les puissances d'un paramètre ; et, quoique je ne sois encore validé que les trois premiers termes des trois développements, les valeurs de ces termes sont assez intéressantes pour les rapports en géométrie.

On peut, pour la surface donnée, considérer les coordonnées x, y, z d'un point quelconque de la surface comme des fonctions déterminées de deux paramètres p, q . Si, de plus, on parameter soit tels, que les équations des trois systèmes de courbes de courbure soient $p = \text{const.}$, $q = \text{const.}$, respectivement, alors les dérivant pour exiger

$$\frac{dx}{dp} \frac{dx}{dq} + \frac{dy}{dp} \frac{dy}{dq} + \frac{dz}{dp} \frac{dz}{dq} = 0,$$

$$\frac{dx}{dp} \frac{dy}{dp} + \frac{dy}{dq} \frac{dz}{dp} + \frac{dz}{dp} \frac{dx}{dq} = 0,$$

et de même pour p et q on conditions x, y, z , considérées toujours comme des fonctions de p, q , seront telles, que

$$x_{pp} + y_{pp} + z_{pp} = \lambda_x, \quad \begin{vmatrix} x_p & y_p \\ x_q & y_q \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

et dans le même cas, $X, Y, Z = y_p z_q - z_p y_q, z_p x_q - x_p z_q, x_p y_q - y_p x_q$. On a donc identiquement

$$X x_p + Y y_p + Z z_p = 0,$$

$$X x_q + Y y_q + Z z_q = 0,$$

et les deux équations identiques sont

$$x_p z_q + y_p y_q + z_p z_q = 0,$$

$$X x_p + Y y_p + Z z_p = 0.$$

Je remarque d'abord que nous pouvons considérer les fonctions x, y, z , sous la forme explicite, sous l'équation de la surface $x = x_0 + a_1 t + a_2 t^2 + \dots$, ainsi peut être quelconque, pour ainsi dire la représentation ; en assumant multiplier par a_2, b_1, c_2 respectivement on aura toujours

$$x_{pq} = a_1 \frac{d^2 \theta}{dp dq} + a_2 \frac{d \theta}{dp} + \dots,$$

(t, Q étant fonctions et plus le tels que η et $\frac{dt}{dt} = 0$ pour les valeurs initiales de p, q . (Voir mon "Mémoire sur les coordonnées curvilignes" [Liouville, t. v., 1840, p. 121]).

Je suppose que les coordonnées de la famille adjacente du paramètre r (pour la surface donnée on obtient $r = 0$). Pour le point (p, q) de la surface adjacente les coordonnées seront respectivement aux équations différentielles de la famille; les coordonnées ξ, η, ζ d'un point quelconque sur cette courbe seront des fonctions de p, q, r , longeitre, pour $r = 0$, se réduisant à x, y, z respectivement, et j'écris

$$\begin{aligned}\xi &= x + ar + a'r^2 + \dots, \\ \eta &= y + br + b'r^2 + \dots, \\ \zeta &= z + cr + c'r^2 + \dots,\end{aligned}$$

où a, b, c, d, a', b', c' , etc., sont des fonctions inconnues de p et q .

Pour exprimer que la courbe coupe orthogonalement les différentes surfaces de la famille, il faut, en écrivant pour abrégé

$$X\xi_p + Y\eta_p + Z\zeta_p = U, \quad X = Ar + Br^2 + \dots, \quad U = Ar + Br^2 + \dots,$$

$$X\xi_p + Y\eta_p + Z\zeta_p = U, \quad X = X + 2rX' + \dots, \quad U = Ar + Br^2 + \dots,$$

$$X\xi_p + Y\eta_p + Z\zeta_p = U, \quad X = X + 2rX' + \dots, \quad U = Ar + Br^2 + \dots,$$

(où $\xi_p = \frac{d\xi}{dp}$, comme pour p, q, r). La condition cherchée est

$$\frac{X}{a} + \frac{2X'}{a} + \frac{2X'}{a} + \frac{2X'}{a} + \dots = 0,$$

laquelle de la cinquième série satisfaire pour une valeur quelconque de r ; on a donc

$$\frac{X}{a} = \frac{Y}{b} = \frac{Z}{c},$$

$$\frac{A}{a} - \frac{2X'}{a} = \frac{B}{b} - \frac{2Y'}{b} = \frac{C}{c} - \frac{2Z'}{c},$$

savoir, les équations (1) contiennent (a, b, c) , les équations (II) contiennent les (a', b', c') , et ainsi de suite. Pour qu'il y ait un système orthogonal, il faut et il suffit que l'on a

$$\xi_p \xi_q + \eta_p \eta_q + \zeta_p \zeta_q = 0,$$

pour toute valeur de r ; on aura

$$x_p x_q + y_p y_q + z_p z_q + a_q + b_q + c_q + a_q + b_q + c_q + a_q + b_q + c_q + \dots = 0;$$

mais l'équation (3) est identifiée d'elle-même; l'équation

$$\frac{X}{a} + \frac{Y}{b} + \frac{Z}{c}$$

[continues sur (1), p. (2)] résulte des équations (4), p. r^2 ainsi que des

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Il paraît donc qu'il y a les trois équations (1), (2) pour déterminer (a, b, c) , les trois équations (II), (3) pour déterminer (a', b', c') , et ainsi de suite. Mais on ne résoud pas la suite suivante. En effet, en multipliant A_1, B_1, C_1 par les valeurs de a, b, c , qu'il contiennent une fonction arbitraire, λ fonction d'un certain ordre. Mais on a aussi d'une équation à différences partielles du second ordre, obtenue au moyen de surfaces d'une fonction arbitraire λ , et lorsque ces équations ont été intégrées, il y aura encore une fonction arbitraire λ , je presume que cette fonction sera certainement déterminer en moyens des équations (3), (4), et ainsi de suite; mais je n'ai pas encore fait les recherches ultérieures.

Par rapport à λ , en supposant cette fonction égale à $\rho = \sqrt{X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2}$, l'équation pour ρ est

$$\frac{X}{\rho} \frac{1}{\frac{dX}{dp}} \frac{dy}{dp} + \frac{Y}{\rho} \frac{1}{\frac{dY}{dq}} \frac{dy}{dq} + \frac{Z}{\rho} \frac{1}{\frac{dZ}{dq}} \frac{dy}{dq} = 0,$$

égal à une fonction donnée par pour ces ρ, q , ainsi λ satisfera à une système analogue à celles des équations.

Pour calculer ces conclusions, parlant des équations (1), (2) la formule (1) donne

$$a \frac{dX}{dx} + b \frac{dY}{dy} + c \frac{dZ}{dz} = 0,$$

où λ est une fonction de p, q ; ces valeurs satisfont évidemment à l'équation (1). La vérification en fait sans peine : j'écris pour abrégier $a_1 z_1, b_1 y_1, c_1 z_1$, et ainsi de même dans les autres notations. L'équation (2) devient

$$\sigma_1 X_p + \sigma_2 X_q + \sigma_3 X_r + \sigma_4 X_s + \sigma_5 X_t = 0,$$

c'est-à-dire

$$\lambda(\sigma_1 z_1 + \sigma_2 x_p + \sigma_3 y_q + \sigma_4 x_r + \sigma_5 y_s + \sigma_6 X = 0;$$

ou nous avons

$$\sigma_1 X_p, \dots, \sigma_5 X_t = 0,$$

ainsi le terme de coefficient $a_2 X_p + \dots$. Nous avons

$$X_p = a y_p \delta + b \frac{1}{y} y_p + c y_p z_p + a y_q + b y_q z_p,$$

et de la

$$X_r = -y_p x_q + y_q x_p,$$

$$\sigma_3 + \sigma_4 = y_p z_q + y_q z_p, \quad x_p z_r = a_2 y_q z_p + a y_p z_q,$$

$$\sigma_5 + \sigma_6 = y_p z_q + y_q z_p, \quad y_p z_r = a y_p z_q + b y_q z_p.$$

et de la, ne faisant la somme des terms tirés évidemment de a, X_p , et b, X_q , respectivement, on trouve

$$a_2 X_p + \dots = (a, x_p, X_p),$$

savoir, $a_2 X_p + b_2 X_p$, est égal a -1 multiplié par le déterminant $-2Xx_q$, c'est-à-dire $2Xa_2 X_p + \dots = 0$. Donc la fonction λ est jusqu'à indeterminable.

Passons aux équations (2), (3). Substituant dans (3) les valeurs de (a, b, c) , ces équations deviennent

$$\frac{A}{a} - \frac{2X'}{a} = \frac{B}{b} - \frac{2Y'}{b} = \frac{C}{c} - \frac{2Z'}{c},$$

$$\lambda(R \cdot E - 2XF) = \lambda(R \cdot E - 2RE) = \lambda(R \cdot E - 2RZ).$$

On y satisfera en écrivant

$$2a'_1 X = 2\rho(a'X_p + a_1X_p) + \lambda^2(R \cdot E - 2RE), \lambda(R \cdot E - 2RZ);$$

où ρ est fonction de (p, q) ; en substituant ces valeurs dans l'équation (2), c'est-à-dire

$$\lambda(R \cdot E - 2RZ),$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$\frac{1}{X}[a'_1 z_1 + (a'x_p + a_1X_p) + \lambda] - X[a_1X_pX_p + a_1X_q] - X_pX_q = 0.$$

Les termes en ρ sont

$$\rho(a'x_qX_q + a_1X_pX_q + a_1z_qX_q) = 2\rho_X X_p,$$

qui s'évanouissent d'eux-mêmes; l'équation se réduit donc à

$$\lambda(a_1z_1 + (a_1z_1)) + \lambda(a_1X_p + a_1X_p + a_1z_pz_p) = 0.$$

Les termes en λ sont

$$\lambda(a_1X_pX_p + a_1X_pX_p) = \rho_X X_p, X_p = 2\rho_X X_pX_p,$$

qui en substituant la valeur $A_2a_1 = a_2$, l'équation se réduit alors à

$$\lambda(a_1z_1 + bX_p + c_1z_p)(a_1X_pX_p + b_1YX_p + 2(X_pX_p + Y_pX_p) = 0.$$

L'on trouve sans peine $A_1X_p + \dots = X(ax_pX_p + bX_p + cz_pX_p) - XX_p$, derrière

$$a_1z_1 + (bX_p + cx_pz_p) - X = 0,$$

en substituant les valeurs $A_2a = \mu$, alors en l'écartant, dilemma

$$A_2b = X_qb_X, X_p, Y_pz_p, Z_pZ_p.$$

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Pour abrégier encore la notation, en lieu de a_2^2 , $a_2^2 + g_2$, $g_2 + b_2$, j'écris simplement 11, et ainsi dans les autres notations; ayant en vue les abréviations

$$11 = x_p^2 + y_p^2 + z_p^2,$$

$$12 = x_p x_q + y_p y_q + z_p z_q,$$

et je remarque que l'équation $12 = 0$ est l'une des équations données par rapport à p, q respectivement, donne $13 + 24 = 0$, $23 + 14 = 0$, équations qui seront pour définir les formules sans expression 13 et 23. Et pour ne suivant nous donnerons des valeurs des déterminants

$$\begin{vmatrix} 11 & 22 \\ 21 & 22 \end{vmatrix}, \dots, \text{ alors, en multipliant par les déterminants analogues } 123 \text{ et}$$

123 respectivement, l'équation $124 = 0$ donne

$$\begin{vmatrix} 11 & 22 \\ 21 & 22 \end{vmatrix} = 0, \quad \begin{vmatrix} 11 & 22 \\ 24 & 32 \end{vmatrix} = 0, \quad \begin{vmatrix} 11 & 22 \\ 24 & 22 \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

dont chacune est tirée la formule $\Sigma = 11, 12, \dots$.

Nous avons

$$\begin{aligned} A &= a_1(yz_p - z_py_p) + b(z_px_p - x_pz_p) + h(x_py_p - y_px_p) = (a_1, b, h)(X, Y, Z), \\ &= \lambda(a_1, b, h)(p, q, r)(p_px_p, \dots, n_pz_p, \dots, t_pY - p_pX), \end{aligned}$$

ou en faisant les valeurs de X_q, Y_q, Z_q ce sera

$$A = X(11 - 12) + X'\{11 + 11 - 11\} - 12, 22 + 11, \dots\}.$$

$$A = X_p(a_q, b_q, c_q) - 14, \dots, 12 - 11, \dots, 22 - 11.$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$A = X_p(X_pY_p - 12, 13 - 11, 14 - 11, 11)).$$

Écrivons pour un moment

$$A = aX + bX_p + eX_q,$$

nous avons

$$A = AX + B(p \cdot X_p) + C(X \cdot p) + R \cdot p \cdot N + (g \cdot p) \cdot R \cdot R + g \cdot p \cdot e,$$

$$AX = ax + (a + p \cdot e),$$

et de la

$$\begin{aligned} Ax_p &= Ax_p + (R \cdot p \cdot e + a)f_p^2 + 2(Rp \cdot e + Rp \cdot e)f_pp_p + (R \cdot p \cdot e + a)f_p^2 \\ &\quad + b_qf \cdot e_p + c \cdot e \cdot e + g \cdot p + h \cdot p \cdot N \cdot e_p \\ &\quad + b_qf \cdot e_p + f \cdot e \cdot e + g \cdot p + h \cdot p \cdot e_p. \end{aligned}$$

[Pp. 381—385.]

Les expressions de $P_p, P_{pq}, \dots$, contiennent les dérivées du troisième ordre

$$\frac{d^3\rho}{dx^3} = a_1, \quad \frac{d^3\rho}{dx^2dy} = b_1, \quad \frac{d^3\rho}{dx^2dz} = c_1, \quad \frac{d^3\rho}{dxdy^2} = d_1, \quad \frac{d^3\rho}{dy^2dz} = e_1, \dots$$

En formant les dérivées de l'équation $22 = 14 = 0$, $13 + 24 = 0$ par rapport à p et q respectivement, on obtient

$$17 + 26 = 2 \cdot 34 = 0,$$

$$18 + 27 + 35 + 44 = 0,$$

$$19 + 28 + 2 \cdot 45 = 0.$$

On obtient alors

$$P_p = -2x_p(44 + 17) + 2x_p(54 + 18) + 2x_p(33 + 19) - n_1$$

$$= -2x_p(44 + 17) + 4 \cdot 24 \cdot 34 + 2x_p(33 + 19) - 22 \cdot 33 - 2 \cdot 34 - 2 \cdot 24 - n_1,$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$P_p = -22 \cdot 33 - 11 \cdot 23 + 2 \cdot 14 \cdot 24 - 33 - 25 - 23 - n_1.$$

On a de même

$$P_q = -22 \cdot 33 + 2 \cdot 14 \cdot 34 - 33 - 24 - 23 - n_1 = -33 - 17 - 19 \cdot 28,$$

$$= -22 \cdot 33 + 2 \cdot 14 \cdot 34 - 33 - 24 - 23 - n_1,$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$P_q = -22 \cdot 33 + 2 \cdot 14 \cdot 34 - 33 - 24 - 23 - n_1(P_q).$$

On obtient sans peine la même formule

$$P_p = a_2, \quad P_q = b_2, \quad P_{pq} = c_2, \quad \dots$$

$$P_q = a_2, \quad P_{pq} = b_2, \quad P_{pq} = b_2, \quad P_{pq} = c_2, \quad \dots$$

et l'on a ainsi

$$\begin{aligned} A_2a_1 + A_2a_2 &= a \cdot \{-2 \cdot 11, 23 - 22, 18 - 22, 11 - 4 \cdot 25 - n_1\} \\ &\quad + b_1\{-22, 14 - 11, 11 - 22, 11 - 12, 25 - 4 \cdot 24 - n_2\} \\ &\quad + c_1\{-22, 14 - 11, 11 - 11, 22 - 11, 22 - 11, 25 - 25 - n_3\} \\ &\quad + b_2\{-22, 11 - 11, 11 - 12 - 11\} \end{aligned}$$

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L'équation à est

$$A_2 a_2 = a_2 a_2, 2x_p x_q, 2x_p x_q, 2x_p x_q, x_p x_q,$$

et on obtient sans peine

$$X_2 X_1 = 44, 13 + 22, 22 + 24, 14 - 23 - 25 - \lambda_1, 23 - 25 - \lambda_1, 22 - n_3,$$

$$XY_1 = 44, 14 + 22, 22 + 22, 14 - 13 - 24 - \lambda_2, 14 - n_3,$$

$$XZ_1 = 44, 12 + 22, 22 + 23, 24 - 12, 14 - n_3,$$

$$XZ_1 = 14, 22 + 22, 22 - n_3.$$

Donc enfin l'équation en λ est

$$\lambda^2 \{11(22 + 22) + 23(33 + 14) - 11, 22 - 33\} - 11 - 22 - n_3 = 0,$$

Cette équation est vérifiée par la valeur $R = \frac{1}{\rho^2}(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)$; en effet, en chercher pour ce moment le quatrième équation à ρ , l'équation s'écrirait sous

$$\lambda^2 \cdot 11, 22 \cdot 28 + 11(22, 22 + 22) - 11 + n_3 \cdot 22 \cdot ZZ_1 + Z_1 Z_2 = 0,$$

c'est-à-dire

$$11 \cdot 22 \cdot 23 + 11(22, 22 + 23) - 12 + 4 \cdot 11 \cdot 24 \cdot XX_1 + Z_1 Z_2 = 0,$$

$$\begin{aligned} &+ 11(22, 11, 14, 22 + 12 \cdot 23 \cdot 24 - 12) + 4 \cdot 11 \cdot 24 \cdot XY_1 + Y_2 + 21 \cdot ZZ_1 \\ &= 2(12 + 11 \cdot 22, 24)(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2), \end{aligned}$$

et l'on remarque qu'à la facteur 2.

Soient l'équation en ρ est

$$11.22\{11.24 + 22.13 - 122.14\} = 0,$$

mais, des équations mentionnées $13 + 24 = 0$ et $(23 + 14)x = 0$, on tire

$$22 \cdot 13 = 12.14 = 22 \cdot 24 \cdot 14 + 11 \cdot 11,$$

$$11 \cdot 24 = 14 \cdot 11.23 + 14 \cdot 11.23,$$

$$11 \cdot 24 = 14, 22, 14 = 23 \cdot 23,$$

$$11 \cdot 24 = 14, 22, 14 \cdot 11.23 + 24 + 11.$$

Donc l'équation contient en facteur $11 \cdot 22$, on l'écartant, elle deviendra

$$\Omega = 11(-22 + 22 \cdot 45) + 11.14, 14 + 22 \cdot 13 + 11.13 + 11.22.$$

Ou a

$$\Omega = -11(22 \cdot 45 + 22) + 22.13 + 11.13 + 11.22.$$

On va vérifier sans peine que XX_1 est actuellement

$$XX_1 = 11.22 + 14 + n_3.$$

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PUISSE FAIRE PARTIE D'UN SYSTÈME ORTHOGONAL.

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Donc, en écrivant $\lambda = \frac{u}{\rho^2}$, l'équation en ρ est contenue dans les termes de u , ρ_p , ρ_q . En effet, l'équation devient

$$-11, 22 - 22, 13 \cdot u + P \left(\frac{V}{\rho}, \frac{du}{dp}, \frac{du}{dq} \right) \cdot 11, 22.$$

ou, comme auparavant, XX_1 , denote $XX_1 = YY_1 + Z_1Z_p$, de même XX_2 denote $XX_2 + YY_2 + ZZ_q$, etc.

L'équation devient ainsi

$$11, 22 \cdot u - 14, 23 \cdot u - 11, 22 \cdot u = 0.$$

Savoir, cette équation est

$$\frac{d^2u}{dpdq} = \frac{1}{R^2} \frac{dR}{dp} \frac{du}{dq} + \frac{1}{R^2} \frac{dR}{dq} \frac{du}{dp} + Ru = 0.$$

Pour compléter la solution, il convient d'exprimer A , B , C en termes de ρ . Nous avons

$$A = a \cdot X + bX_p, X_p + cX_q, X_q + bX_p + cX_p, X_p + hX_pX_q;$$

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{1}{\rho}(\dots) &= \rho a + (ax_p + hx_q)x_p + (hx_p + bx_q)x_q + aX_pX_p + (XX_1) \\ &= \rho a + (ax_p + hx_q)x_q + (ax_p + bx_q)x_q + a(XX_1)\rho_p^2, \end{aligned}$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$\frac{1}{\rho^2}a(4 \cdot 12 \cdot 14 + 22, 22) + a, 22, 13 + h \cdot 22, 14 - \rho_p 11, 22 \cdot XX_1\rho;$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$\begin{aligned} &\frac{1}{\rho^2}a(11, 22 + 22, 13) + (ax_p + 2bx_p y_p + 11, 22)\rho - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(ax_p + hx_q)\rho_p \\ &\frac{1}{\rho^2}(11, 22 + 11, 22, 14)\rho + 11, 22 \cdot 13\rho^2 - 11, 22\rho_p - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(bx_p + bx_q)\rho_p \end{aligned}$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$X(11, 22 + 22, 13)\rho - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(ax_p + hx_q)\rho_p;$$

Le terme entre [] qui dénote la formule de a , b , c , etc., a , etc., en rappelant les valeurs de quantités respectivement en quantités de p , q , p , etc., on, ce qui est la même chose,

$$X(11, 22)(bz_p\rho_p + 11, 22)\rho_p\rho_q + (XX_p)\rho_q^2;$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$X(11, 22)\rho - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(ax_p + hx_q)\rho_p.$$

Nous avons donc

$$A = \rho \frac{\delta X}{\delta s}(11, 22) + \frac{1}{\rho}\rho_p\rho_q - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(ax_p + bx_q)\rho_q + \rho_p.$$

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Nous avons

$$11 = E, \quad 22 = G, \quad V = \sqrt{EG},$$

donc, en dérivant, pour ρ, q ,

$$\frac{p}{\sqrt{EG}}(11, 12) + \frac{q}{\sqrt{EG}}(22, 12) + \dots = \rho.$$

la valeur de

$$A = \rho X + \frac{1}{\sqrt{EG}}(11, 12) + \dots \frac{d\rho}{dq} + \frac{d\sigma}{dp}.$$

avec des expressions analogues de B et C . Dans les expressions $2dx + \dots$ qui précèdent de remplacer θ et σ on auxiliaires moyens X, Y, Z .

Donc, dans les expressions de a, b, c on aura

$$\begin{aligned} \xi &= z + \frac{\rho X}{\sqrt{EG}} \left[\frac{(11, 12)^2}{2EG} + \frac{(12 \cdot 12 + 12 \cdot 22)}{2EG} - \dots \right] e^{-\dots}, \\ \eta &= y + \frac{\rho Y}{\sqrt{EG}} \left[\frac{(11, 12)^2}{2EG} + \frac{(12 \cdot 12 + 12 \cdot 22)}{2EG} - \dots \right] e^{-\dots}, \\ \zeta &= z + \frac{\rho Z}{\sqrt{EG}} \left[\frac{(11, 12)^2}{2EG} + \frac{(12 \cdot 12 + 12 \cdot 22)}{2EG} - \dots \right] e^{-\dots}; \end{aligned}$$

Je remarque que l'on satisfait à toutes les conditions en prenant $\lambda = \text{const.}$, ou en fait à la même chose, $p = 0$ et $r = 0$; mais alors la famille en ρ n'est pas la même; savoir, la famille est ici des surfaces parallèles à la surface donnée.

[Pp. 1800—1803.]

J'ai traité que l'équation différentielle du troisième ordre, sous la forme [dénouée trouvée], contient le facteur étrange $XX' + YY + ZZ$, qui déparaît de ce facteur devient beaucoup plus simple. La réduction et aussi la nouvelle solution dont je me suis occupé auparavant l'équation réduite seront tirées des deux quantités appelées quotiques.

Je prends V et l'équation réduite, X, Y, Z les coefficients différentielles du premier ordre, a, b, c, f, g, h les coefficients du second ordre,

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H)(\delta x, \delta y, \delta z)^2 = 0$$

l'équation différentielle des courbes de courbure ; savoir

$$\begin{aligned} A &= 2(Zh - Yg), \\ B &= 2(Xf - Zh), \\ C &= 2(Yg - Xf), \\ F &= XY - aZ + Yh - Zg, \\ G &= Y(a - c) + Zf - Xh, \\ H &= Z(b - a) + Xg - Yf, \end{aligned}$$

et

$$[(A), (B), (C), (F), (G), (H)](\delta x, \delta y)^2 = 0$$

savoir :

$$\begin{aligned} (A) &= BC - F^2 = -F^2 VZ, \\ (B) &= CA - G^2 = -G^2 ZX, \\ (C) &= AB - H^2 = -H^2 XY, \\ (F) &= GH - AF = aVZX - (a - c)YZ + bYZ + cVZ - (a + b)fVZ - bgYZ + h \cdot XZ + a \cdot XZZ, \\ (G) &= HF - BG = bVXY - cZX - hYX + aXY - cXY + Y(c - a)g + bYZ - YgZ + 2cZX, \\ (H) &= FG - CH = cVYZ - aXY + hVXY - gVYZ - (b - a)hXY - aXZZ + bYVZ - cZV, \end{aligned}$$

ou qui explique la signification des symboles $(A), (B), \dots$; aussi

$$V = X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2,$$

Cela étant, à chaque point P de la surface $U = 0$, je prends de la manière usagete deux droites infiniment voisines PP' et PP' comme deux fonction quelconque des coordonnées x, y, z du point P . Si nous nous voulons exprimer la condition pour qu'elle se rencontre PP' et PP' , ou la même chose, les deux surfaces $V = f(x, y, z) = 0$ et celles de la surface voisine $r = f(x, y, z) + c = 0$.

Or, si la surface donnée $V = 0$ et la surface voisine sont des mêmes considérations d'une famille $r = f(x, y, z) = 0$, on auroit, l'équation de la surface donnée étant comme ci-dessus $P = f(x, y, z) - r = 0$, et celle de la surface voisine étant $r = f(x, y, z) + c = 0$,

$$P = \frac{\rho}{V}, \quad V = X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2,$$

oh c'est une constante. L'équation devient alors

$$[(A), \dots](\rho_x, \rho_y, \rho_z, \alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta x dr) = 0$$

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où, à présent, $X, Y, Z, a, b, c, f, g, h$ dénotent les coefficients différentiels de $f(x, y, z)$, ou (ce qui est la même chose) de l'équation ρ ; considérer comme fonction des coordonnées x, y, z . Cette équation est donc une équation aux dérivées du troisième ordre, satisfaite à la fonction ρ , qui satisfait à une équation aux dérivées partielles du troisième ordre d'une famille de surfaces $\rho = f(x, y, z)$. C'était l'équation Ω du numéro ci-dessus, qui Ω s'évolue de quelque facteur V .

J'écris $\delta X = X_0 dx + Y_0 dy$,

et de là

$$[X, Y]\delta x + [Y, Z]\delta y + [X, Z]\delta z = [\delta x, \delta y, \delta z]; \quad bXx + cXy + aXz = bX, \quad hXy + bYx, \quad hXz + cZx,$$

respectivement, on trouve

$$\delta_1 \frac{a}{\rho} - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(-aX + bYX + 2a)dX^2 + \frac{1}{\rho^2}(bXY + (-\frac{bX}{\rho^2} - bY)dX^2,$$

ou, en dérivant $\omega = \omega + n$, $\omega = h + a$, l'on a sans peine

$$\delta_1 \frac{a}{\rho} - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(-\omega - x + g + bY)dX^2 + \frac{1}{\rho^2}(bXy\rho + bXY + (bXy\rho + bXy)dX^2,$$

et, en supposant pour le moment

$$\delta_1 \frac{a}{\rho} - \frac{1}{\rho^2}(\omega - n - 6\omega + g + bY)dX^2 + \frac{1}{\rho^2}(bXy\rho + bXy + (bXy\rho + bXy)dX^2,$$

et, en multipliant respectivement par $P^2 = -6\omega + g + bY$, $P^2 = (bXy\rho + bXy)dX^2$, et ainsi nous avons donc $\delta_1 \frac{1}{\rho}$, etc., et l'équation, multipliable un peu seulement par ρ^2 , sera

$$(A) + (B)\delta + (C)\delta + (D)\delta x = 2(B)\delta a = 0,$$

et la même pour second terme :

$$(A)(\delta) - (B)(\delta + (C)\delta + (D)\delta x = 2(B)\delta a = 0.$$

Or je trouve que Σ est divisible par V^2 ; savoir, j'écris

$$[(A), \dots](\omega), (\delta a) = 2P[(A), \dots](\delta X, \delta Y, \delta Z, \delta a, \delta a, \delta a)$$

de manière que l'équation est

$$[(A), \dots](ba) + V[(A), \dots]\delta X = 0,$$

ce qui, pour la réduction cherchée, est

$$[(A), \dots](ba) + (b)(c) - (c)(b) = [(A), \dots](ba, bX, bY, bZ) = 0;$$

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où bX, bY, bZ dénotent respectivement $aX + gY + gZ, hX + bY + fZ, gX + fY + cZ$; l'équation se réduit donc à

$$[(A), \dots](ba, \dots) = 0 = 0,$$

où il peut être exprimé si voulant l'une l'une quelconque des trois formes

$$\begin{aligned} &= -2[(A), \dots](ba, \dots), \\ &= -4[(A), \dots](bX, bY, bZ), \\ &= -4, \quad bX, \quad bY, \quad bZ; \end{aligned}$$

Prenant la première forme, l'équation est

$$[(A), \dots](ba, \dots) - 2[(A), \dots](ba, \dots) = 0,$$

ou, ce qui est la même chose,

$$\begin{aligned} &(A)(ba + (b)(\delta b + (C)\delta c + 2(F)(\delta + 2(G)\delta g + 2(H)\delta h \\ &- 2[(A)(\delta a + (b)(\delta b + (c)(\delta c + 2(f)(\delta f + 2(g)\delta g + 2(h)\delta h] = 0, \end{aligned}$$

où les coefficients sont des fonctions données de $X, Y, Z, a, b, c, f, g, h$, mais les coefficients différentielles de ρ du premier et du second ordre, et δ dénote $Xd_x + Yd_y + Zd_z$.

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On Curvature and Orthogonal Surfaces.

[From the *Philosophical Transactions of the Royal Society of London*, vol. CLXIII. (for the year 1873), pp. 229–251. Received December 27, 1872,—Read February 13, 1873.]

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THE principal object of the present Memoir is the establishment of the partial differential equation of the third order satisfied by the parameter of a family of surfaces belonging to a triple orthogonal system. It was first remarked by Bouquet that a given family of surfaces does not in general belong to an orthogonal system, but that (in order to its doing so) a condition must be satisfied; it was afterwards shown by Serret that the condition is that the parameter, considered as a function of the coordinates, must satisfy a partial differential equation of the third order: this equation was not obtained by him or the other French geometers engaged on the subject, although methods of obtaining it, essentially equivalent but differing in form, were given by Darboux and Levy; the last-named writer even found a particular form of the equation, viz. what the general equation becomes on writing therein $X = 0, Y = 0$ (X, Y, Z the first derived functions, or quantities proportional to the cosine-inclinations of the normal). Using Levy's method, I obtained the general equation, and communicated it to the French Academy, [518]. My result was, however, of a very complicated form, owing, as I afterwards discovered, to its being encumbered with the extraneous factor $X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2$; I succeeded, by some difficult reductions, in getting rid of this factor, and so obtaining the equation in the form given in the present memoir, viz.

$$((A), (B), (C), (F), (G), (H) \delta a, \delta b, \delta c, 2\delta f, 2\delta g, 2\delta h)$$

$$-2((A), (B), (C), (F), (G), (H) a, b, c, 2f, 2g, 2h) = 0;$$

but the method was an inconvenient one, and I was led to reconsider the question. The present investigation, although the analytical transformations are very long, is in theory extremely simple: I consider a given surface, and at each point thereof take along the normal an infinitesimal length p (not a constant, but an arbitrary function

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of the coordinates), the extremities of these distances forming a new surface, say the *vicinal* surface; and the points on the same normal being considered as corresponding points, say this is the conormal correspondence of vicinal surfaces. In order that the two surfaces may belong to an orthogonal system, it is necessary and sufficient that at each point of the given surface the principal tangents (tangents to the curves of curvature) shall correspond to the principal tangents at the corresponding point of the vicinal surface; and the condition for this is that p shall satisfy a partial differential equation of the second order,

$$((A), (B), (C), (F), (G), (H) d_x, d_y, d_z)^2 p = 0,$$

where the coefficients depend on the first and second differential coefficients of U , if $U = 0$ is the equation of the given surface. Now, considering the given surface as belonging to a family, or writing its equation in the form $r - r(x, y, z) = 0$ (the last r a functional symbol), the condition in order that the vicinal surface shall belong to this family, or say that it shall coincide with the surface $r + \delta r - r(x, y, z) = 0$, is $p = \frac{\delta r}{V}$, where $V = \sqrt{X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2}$, if X, Y, Z are the first differential coefficients of $r(x, y, z)$, that is, of the parameter r considered as a function of the coordinates; we have thus the equation

$$((A), (B), (C), (F), (G), (H) d_x, d_y, d_z)^2 \frac{1}{V} = 0,$$

viz. the coefficients being functions of the first and second differential coefficients of r , and V being a function of the first differential coefficients of r , this is in fact a relation involving the first, second, and third differential coefficients of r , or it is the partial differential equation to be satisfied by the parameter r considered as a function of the coordinates. After all reductions, this equation assumes the form previously mentioned.

Article Nos. 1 to 21. On the Curvature of Surfaces.

1. Curvature is a metrical theory having reference to the circle at infinity; each point in space may be regarded as the vertex of a cone passing through this circle, say the circular cone; a line and plane through the vertex are at right angles to each other when they are polar line and polar plane in regard to the cone; and so two lines or two planes are at right angles when they are harmonics in regard to the cone, that is, when each line lies in the polar plane, or each plane passes through the polar line of the other. A plane through the vertex meets the cone in two lines, which are the “circular lines” in the plane and through the point; a line through the vertex has through it two tangent planes, which might be called the “circular planes” of the point and through the line; but the term is hardly required. Lines in the plane and through the point, at right angles to each other, are also harmonics (polar lines) in regard to the two circular lines.

2. Consider now a surface, and any point thereof; we have at this point a tangent plane and a normal. The tangent plane meets the surface in a curve having

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at the point a node, and the tangents to the two branches of the curve (being of course lines in the tangent plane) are the “chief tangents” of the surface at the point.

3. The chief tangents are the intersections of the tangent plane by a quadric cone, which may be called the chief cone; but it is important to observe that this cone is not independent of the particular form under which the equation of the surface is presented. To explain this, suppose that the rational equation of the surface is $U = 0$; taking ξ, η, ζ as current coordinates measured from the point as origin, the equation of the chief cone is $(\xi d_x + \eta d_y + \zeta d_z)^2 U = 0$, where x, y, z denote the coordinates of the point. But it is in the sequel necessary to present the equation of the surface in a different manner; say we have an equation between the coordinates (x, y, z) and a parameter r (r being therefore in general an irrational function of x, y, z), which, when $r = r_1$, reduces itself to $U = 0$: we have then $r = r_1$ as the equation of the surface; and the corresponding equation of the chief cone is $(\xi d_x + \eta d_y + \zeta d_z)^2 r = 0$; this is not the same as the cone $(\xi d_x + \eta d_y + \zeta d_z)^2 U = 0$, although of course it intersects the tangent plane in the same two lines, viz. the chief lines; and so in general there is a distinct chief cone corresponding to each form of the equation of the surface. But adopting a definite form of equation, we have a definite chief cone intersecting the tangent plane in the chief tangents.

4. Observe that the equations $U = 0, r = r_1$, although each relating to one and the same surface, serve to represent this surface, and that in different ways, as belonging to a family of surfaces, viz. one of these is the family $U = \text{const.}$, and the other the family $r = \text{const.}$ In order to represent a given surface as belonging to a certain family, we need the irrational form of equation; thus r denoting the irrational function of x, y, z determined by the equation

$$\frac{x^2}{a+r} + \frac{y^2}{b+r} + \frac{z^2}{c+r} = 1,$$

we have $r = 0$ as the equation of the ellipsoid $\frac{x^2}{a} + \frac{y^2}{b} + \frac{z^2}{c} = 1$, considered as belonging to a family of confocal quadrics.

5. Although at first sight presenting some difficulty, it is convenient to use the same letter r to denote the parameter considered as a function of the coordinates, and the special value of the parameter; thus in general the equation of a surface may be written $r(x, y, z) - r = 0$ (in which form the first r may be regarded as a functional symbol), or simply $r - r = 0$, viz. the first r here denotes the given function of (x, y, z) , and the second r the particular value of the parameter.

6. By what precedes we have through the point and in the tangent plane two circular lines, the intersections of the tangent plane by the circular cone having the point for its vertex.

We have also through the point and in the tangent plane two other lines, termed the principal tangents, viz. the definition of these is that they are the double (or sibiconjugate) lines of the involution formed by the circular lines and the chief tangents, or, what is the same thing, they are the bisectors (and as such at right angles to each other) of the angles formed by the chief tangents.

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7. The principal tangents may also be considered as the intersections of the tangent plane by a quadric cone, called the principal cone; this being a cone constructed by means of the circular cone and the chief cone, and thus depending on the particular chief cone, that is, on the form of the equation of the surface. The definition is that the principal cone is the locus of a line (through the point), such that the line itself, the perpendicular (or harmonic in regard to the circular cone) of the polar plane of the line in regard to the chief cone, and the normal of the surface are *in plano*.

8. Analytically, taking, as before, (x, y, z) for the coordinates of the point, and u, v, w as current coordinates measured from the point as origin, then the equation of the circular cone is $u^2 + v^2 + w^2 = 0$; and taking $Xu + Yv + Zw = 0$ for the equation of the tangent plane, and $(a, b, c, f, g, h, u, v, w)^2 = 0$ for that of the chief cone, then, if the line be $u : v : w = \xi : \eta : \zeta$, we have

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h, \xi, \eta, \zeta, u, v, w) = 0$$

for the equation of the polar plane, and thence

$$u : v : w = \begin{vmatrix} a\xi + h\eta + g\zeta & h\xi + b\eta + f\zeta & g\xi + f\eta + c\zeta \\ X & Y & Z \end{vmatrix}$$

for those of the perpendicular, or harmonic in regard to the circular cone; also for the normal $u, v, w = X : Y : Z$; whence, if the three lines are *in plano*, we have

$$\begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ a\xi + h\eta + g\zeta & h\xi + b\eta + f\zeta & g\xi + f\eta + c\zeta \\ X & Y & Z \end{vmatrix} = 0$$

as the equation of the principal cone. This is in the sequel written, for shortness, as

$$\begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ \delta\xi & \delta\eta & \delta\zeta \\ X & Y & Z \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

9. Consider any point P' , not in general on the surface, in the neighbourhood of the point on the surface, say P ; then the point P' has in regard to the surface a polar plane, which plane, however, is dependent on the particular form of equation—viz. x', y', z' being the coordinates of P' , and U' the same function of these that U is of x, y, z , then the form $U = 0$ of the equation of the surface gives for P' the polar plane $(ud_{x'} + vd_{y'} + wd_{z'}) U' = 0$; and we may through P' draw hereto a perpendicular (or harmonic in regard to the circular cone), say this is the normal line of P' . Then for points P' in the neighbourhood of P , when these are such that their normal lines

meet the normal at P , the locus of P' is the before-mentioned principal cone. The analytical investigation presents no difficulty.

10. Taking P' on the surface, the normal line of P' becomes the normal at a consecutive point P' of the surface (being now a line independent of the particular form of equation), and this normal meets the normal at P ; that is, we have the

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principal cone meeting the tangent plane in two lines, the principal tangents, such that at a consecutive point P' on either of these the normal meets the normal at P ; viz. we have the principal tangents at the tangents of the two curves of curvature through the point P .

The plane through the normal and a principal tangent is termed a principal plane; we have thus at the point of the surface two principal planes, forming with the tangent plane an orthogonal triad of planes.

11. I proceed to further develop the theory, commencing with the following lemma:

Lemma. *Given the line $Xu + Yv + Zw = 0$, and conic*

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h \ u, v, w)^2 = 0,$$

then, to determine the coordinates (u_1, v_1, w_1) , (u_2, v_2, w_2) of the points of intersection of the line and conic, we have

$$u : v : w = Y\zeta - Z\eta : Z\xi - X\zeta : X\eta - Y\xi,$$

or, what is the same thing, we have

$$(a, \dots Y\zeta - Z\eta, Z\xi - X\zeta, X\eta - Y\xi)^2 = 0$$

as the equation, in line coordinates, of the two points of intersection. The proof is obvious.

12. Making the equations refer to a plane and a cone, and writing throughout ξ, η, ζ as current point coordinates, the theorem is:

Given the plane $X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0$, and cone

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h \ \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0;$$

then, to determine the lines of intersection of the plane and cone, we have

$$(a, \dots Y\zeta - Z\eta, Z\xi - X\zeta, X\eta - Y\xi)^2 = 0$$

as the equation of the pair of planes at right angles to the two lines respectively.

13. Denoting the coefficients by (a) , (b) , &c., that is, writing

$$(a, \dots Y\zeta - Z\eta, Z\xi - X\zeta, X\eta - Y\xi)^2 = ((a), (b), (c), (f), (g), (h) \ \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2,$$

the values of these are

$$\begin{aligned} (a) &= bZ^2 + cY^2 - 2fYZ, \\ (b) &= cX^2 + aZ^2 - 2gZX, \\ (c) &= aY^2 + bX^2 - 2hXY, \\ (f) &= -aYZ - fX^2 + gXY + hXZ, \\ (g) &= -bZX + fYX - gY^2 + hYZ, \\ (h) &= -cXY + fZX + gZY - hZ^2. \end{aligned}$$

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We have the following identities:

$$\begin{aligned}(a)X + (h)Y + (g)Z &= 0, \\ (h)X + (b)Y + (f)Z &= 0, \\ (g)X + (f)Y + (c)Z &= 0, \\ ((a), \dots X, Y, Z \dots) &= -(X^2, Y^2, Z^2, YZ, ZX, XY) \phi,\end{aligned}$$

that is, $(b)(c) - (f)^2 = -X^2\phi$, &c., where

$$\phi = (a, \dots gh - af, \dots X, Y, Z)^2.$$

Writing also

$$aX + hY + gZ, \quad hX + bY + fZ, \quad gX + fY + cZ = \delta X, \delta Y, \delta Z,$$

and $X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2 = V^2$; also $a + b + c = \omega$, then

$$\begin{aligned}(a) &= (b + c)V^2 - \omega X^2 + X\delta X - Y\delta Y - Z\delta Z, \\ (b) &= (c + a)V^2 - \omega Y^2 - X\delta X + Y\delta Y - Z\delta Z, \\ (c) &= (a + b)V^2 - \omega Z^2 - X\delta X - Y\delta Y + Z\delta Z, \\ (f) &= -fV^2 - \omega YZ + Y\delta Z + Z\delta Y, \\ (g) &= -gV^2 - \omega ZX + Z\delta X + X\delta Z, \\ (h) &= -hV^2 - \omega XY + X\delta Y + Y\delta X.\end{aligned}$$

14. I give also the following lemma:

Lemma. *The condition in order that the plane $X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0$ may meet the cones*

$$\begin{aligned}(A, B, C, F, G, H \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 &= 0, \\ (A', B', C', F', G', H' \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 &= 0\end{aligned}$$

in two pairs of lines harmonically related to each other, is

$$(BC' + B'C - 2FF', \dots, GH' + G'H - AF' - A'F, \dots X, Y, Z)^2 = 0.$$

Writing here

$$(A, \dots Y\zeta - Z\eta, Z\xi - X\zeta, X\eta - Y\xi)^2 = ((A), (B), (C), (F), (G), (H) \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2,$$

that is, $(A) = BZ^2 + CY^2 - 2FYZ$, &c., the condition may be written

$$(A, \dots A', B', C', F', G', H')^2 = 0,$$

or say

$$(A)A' + (B)B' + (C)C' + 2(F)F' + 2(G)G' + 2(H)H' = 0,$$

and we may, it is clear, interchange the accented and unaccented letters respectively.

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15. I take $r - r = 0$ for the equation of a surface, X, Y, Z for the first derived functions of r , (a, b, c, f, g, h) for the second derived functions. The equation of the tangent plane at the point (x, y, z) , taking ξ, η, ζ as current coordinates measured from this point, is

$$X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0;$$

the equation of the chief cone in regard to this form of the equation of the surface is

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h \ \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0,$$

and the equation of the circular cone is $\xi^2 + \eta^2 + \zeta^2 = 0$, or, what is the same thing,

$$(1, 1, 1, 0, 0, 0 \ \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0.$$

Imagine a quadric cone

$$(A, B, C, F, G, H \ \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0,$$

such that it meets the tangent plane in the sibiconjugate lines of the involution formed by the intersections of the tangent plane by the chief cone and the circular cone respectively; that is, in a pair of lines harmonically related to the intersections with the chief cone, and also to the intersections with the circular cone; the conditions are

$$(A, \dots a, b, c, f, g, h)^2 = 0,$$

and

$$(A) + (B) + (C) = 0,$$

viz. if only these two conditions are satisfied the cone will intersect the tangent plane in the two principal tangents.

16. The principal cone, writing, for shortness,

$$aX + hY + gZ, \quad hX + bY + fZ, \quad gX + fY + cZ = \delta X, \delta Y, \delta Z,$$

was before taken to be the cone

$$\begin{vmatrix} \xi & \eta & \zeta \\ \delta\xi & \delta\eta & \delta\zeta \\ X & Y & Z \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

Representing this equation by

$$\frac{1}{2}(A, B, C, F, G, H \ \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0,$$

the expressions of the coefficients are

$$\begin{aligned} A &= 2hZ - 2gY, \\ B &= 2fX - 2hZ, \\ C &= 2gY - 2fX, \\ F &= hY - gZ - (b - c)X, \\ G &= fZ - hX - (c - a)Y, \\ H &= gX - fY - (a - b)Z. \end{aligned}$$

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These values give

$$\begin{aligned} AX + HY + GZ &= Z\delta Y - Y\delta Z, \\ HX + BY + FZ &= X\delta Z - Z\delta X, \\ GX + FY + CZ &= Y\delta X - X\delta Y; \end{aligned}$$

whence also

$$(A, \dots X, Y, Z)^2 = 0,$$

as is, in fact, at once obvious from the determinant-form; and also

$$A + B + C = 0.$$

17. Writing for shortness

$$(\mathfrak{a}, \mathfrak{b}, \mathfrak{c}, \mathfrak{f}, \mathfrak{g}, \mathfrak{h}) = (bc - f^2, ca - g^2, ab - h^2, gh - af, hf - bg, fg - ch),$$

we find

$$\begin{aligned} A\mathfrak{a} + H\mathfrak{h} + G\mathfrak{g} &= \omega(hZ - gY) + hZ - gY, \\ H\mathfrak{h} + B\mathfrak{b} + F\mathfrak{f} &= \omega(fX - hZ) + fX - hZ, \\ G\mathfrak{g} + F\mathfrak{f} + C\mathfrak{c} &= \omega(gY - fX) + gY - fX; \end{aligned}$$

whence

$$(A, \dots \mathfrak{a}, \dots) = 0.$$

18. By what precedes, we have

$$((A), \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0$$

for the equation of the two principal planes, where the coefficients (A) , (B) , &c. are functions of A , B , &c. and of X , Y , Z , as mentioned above. These coefficients satisfy of course the several relations similar to those satisfied by (a) , (b) , &c., and other relations dependent on the expressions of A , B , &c. in terms of a , b , &c. and X , Y , Z .

19. Proceeding to consider the coefficients (A) , (B) , &c., we have then

$$(A) + (B) + (C) = (A + B + C)V^2 - (A, \dots X, Y, Z)^2,$$

that is

$$(A) + (B) + (C) = 0.$$

Observing the relation $A + B + C = 0$, the equations analogous to

$$(a) = (b + c)V^2 - (a + b + c)X^2 + \&c. \quad \text{are} \quad (A) = -AV^2 + X\delta'X - Y\delta'Y - Z\delta'Z, \quad \&c.$$

if for a moment we write $\delta'X$, $\delta'Y$, $\delta'Z$ to denote the functions

$$AX + HY + GZ, \quad HX + BY + FZ, \quad GX + FY + CZ.$$

But, from the above values, $X\delta'X + Y\delta'Y + Z\delta'Z = 0$, or the equation is $(A) = -AV^2 + 2X\delta'X$, that is $= -AV^2 + 2X(Z\delta'Y - Y\delta'Z)$. The equation for (F) is $(F) = -FV^2 + Y\delta'Z + Z\delta'Y$, where $Y\delta'Z + Z\delta'Y$ is $= Y(Y\delta'X - X\delta'Y) + Z(X\delta'Z - Z\delta'X)$, viz. this is

$$= (Y^2 - Z^2)\delta'X - XY\delta'Y + XZ\delta'Z.$$

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We have thus the system of equations

$$\begin{aligned} (A) &= -AV^2 && + 2XZ\delta'Y - 2XY\delta'Z, \\ (B) &= -BV^2 - 2YZ\delta'X && + 2XY\delta'Z, \\ (C) &= -CV^2 + 2YZ\delta'X - 2XZ\delta'Y, \\ (F) &= -FV^2 + (Y^2 - Z^2)\delta'X - XY\delta'Y + XZ\delta'Z, \\ (G) &= -GV^2 + XY\delta'X + (Z^2 - X^2)\delta'Y - YZ\delta'Z, \\ (H) &= -HV^2 - XZ\delta'X + YZ\delta'Y + (X^2 - Y^2)\delta'Z. \end{aligned}$$

20. We hence find

$$\begin{aligned}(A)a + (H)h + (G)g &= -(Aa + Hh + Gg)V^2 + (Z\delta Y - Y\delta Z)\delta X + XP, \\ (H)h + (B)b + (F)f &= -(Hh + Bb + Ff)V^2 + (X\delta Z - Z\delta X)\delta Y + YQ, \\ (G)g + (F)f + (C)c &= -(Gg + Ff + Cc)V^2 + (Y\delta X - X\delta Y)\delta Z + ZR,\end{aligned}$$

if for shortness

$$\begin{aligned}P &= (gY - hZ)\delta X + (aZ - gX)\delta Y + (hX - aY)\delta Z, \\ Q &= (fY - bZ)\delta X + (hZ - fX)\delta Y + (bX - hY)\delta Z, \\ R &= (cY - fZ)\delta X + (gZ - cX)\delta Y + (fX - gY)\delta Z.\end{aligned}$$

Forming the sum $PX + QY + RZ$, the coefficient of δX is found to be

$$= -Z(hX + bY + fZ) + Y(gX + fY + cZ), = -Z\delta Y + Y\delta Z;$$

hence the whole is

$$= \delta X(Y\delta Z - Z\delta Y) + \delta Y(Z\delta X - X\delta Z) + \delta Z(X\delta Y - Y\delta X), \text{ which is } = 0, \text{ that is,}$$

$$PX + QY + RZ = 0.$$

21. Hence, adding, we find

$$((A), \dots a, \dots) = 0,$$

viz. in this and the before-mentioned equation

$$(A) + (B) + (C) = 0,$$

we have the a posteriori verification that the cone $(A, \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0$ cuts the tangent plane in the double lines of the involution.

In what precedes I have given only those relations between the several sets of quantities $a, \mathbf{a}, (a), A, (A)$, &c. which have been required for establishing the results last obtained; but there are various other relations required in the sequel, and which will be obtained as they are wanted.

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22. We consider a surface $U = 0$ (or $r = r$), and at each point P thereof measure along the normal an infinitesimal length p , dependent on the position of the point P (that is, p is a function of x, y, z). We have thus a point P' , the coordinates of which are

$$x', y', z' = x + p\alpha, y + p\beta, z + p\gamma,$$

where α, β, γ are the cosine-inclinations of the normal, that is,

$$\alpha, \beta, \gamma = \frac{X}{V}, \frac{Y}{V}, \frac{Z}{V}, \text{ if } V = \sqrt{X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2};$$

the locus of P' is of course a surface, say the vicinal surface, and we require to find the direction of the normal at P' , or, what is the same thing, the differential equation $X' dx' + Y' dy' + Z' dz' = 0$ of the surface. We have

$$\begin{aligned}dx' &= (1 + d_x p\alpha) dx + d_y p\alpha dy + d_z p\alpha dz, \\ dy' &= d_x p\beta dx + (1 + d_y p\beta) dy + d_z p\beta dz, \\ dz' &= d_x p\gamma dx + d_y p\gamma dy + (1 + d_z p\gamma) dz, \\ 0 &= X dx + Y dy + Z dz;\end{aligned}$$

whence, eliminating dx, dy, dz , we have between dx', dy', dz' a linear equation, the coefficients of which may be taken to be X', Y', Z' . Taking these only as far as the first power of p , we have

$$X' = X(1 + d_y p \beta + d_z p \gamma) - Y d_x p \beta - Z d_x p \gamma,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$X' = X(1 + d_x p \alpha + d_y p \beta + d_z p \gamma) - X d_x p \alpha - Y d_x p \beta - Z d_x p \gamma,$$

with the like expressions for Y' and Z' . I proceed to reduce these. The formula for X' is

$$\begin{aligned} X' = X \{ & 1 + p(d_x \alpha + d_y \beta + d_z \gamma) + \alpha d_x p + \beta d_y p + \gamma d_z p \} \\ & - p(X d_x \alpha + Y d_x \beta + Z d_x \gamma) - (\alpha X + \beta Y + \gamma Z) d_x p. \end{aligned}$$

23. I write, for shortness, $\delta = X d_x + Y d_y + Z d_z$, whence $\delta X, \delta Y, \delta Z = aX + hY + gZ, hX + bY + fZ, gX + fY + cZ$, agreeing with the former significations of $\delta X, \delta Y, \delta Z$; also $V d_x V, V d_y V, V d_z V = \delta X, \delta Y, \delta Z$, and $V \delta V = X \delta X + Y \delta Y + Z \delta Z$. It is now easy to form the values of

$$\begin{aligned} d_x \alpha, d_x \beta, d_x \gamma, \quad \text{viz. these are} \quad & \frac{a}{V} - \frac{X \delta X}{V^3}, \quad \frac{h}{V} - \frac{Y \delta X}{V^3}, \quad \frac{g}{V} - \frac{Z \delta X}{V^3}, \\ d_y \alpha, d_y \beta, d_y \gamma, & \frac{h}{V} - \frac{X \delta Y}{V^3}, \quad \frac{b}{V} - \frac{Y \delta Y}{V^3}, \quad \frac{f}{V} - \frac{Z \delta Y}{V^3}, \\ d_z \alpha, d_z \beta, d_z \gamma, & \frac{g}{V} - \frac{X \delta Z}{V^3}, \quad \frac{f}{V} - \frac{Y \delta Z}{V^3}, \quad \frac{c}{V} - \frac{Z \delta Z}{V^3}; \end{aligned}$$

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and hence

$$\begin{aligned} d_x \alpha + d_y \beta + d_z \gamma &= \frac{a + b + c}{V} - \frac{\delta V}{V^2}, \\ X d_x \alpha + Y d_x \beta + Z d_x \gamma &= \frac{\delta X}{V} - \frac{V^2}{V^3} \delta X, = 0, \end{aligned}$$

and we have

$$X' = X \left\{ 1 + p \left(\frac{a + b + c}{V} - \frac{\delta V}{V^2} \right) + \frac{1}{V} \delta p \right\} - V d_x p,$$

with the like values of Y' and Z' . But we are only concerned with the ratios $X' : Y' : Z'$; whence, dividing the foregoing values by the coefficient in $\{ \}$, and taking the second terms only to the first order in p , we have simply

$$X', Y', Z' = X - V d_x p, Y - V d_y p, Z - V d_z p.$$

24. We may investigate the condition in order that the surface x', y', z' may be the consecutive surface $r + dr = r(x, y, z)$. This will be the case of

$$r + dr = r \left(x + p \frac{X}{V}, y + p \frac{Y}{V}, z + p \frac{Z}{V} \right),$$

that is, $r + dr = r + pV$, or $p = \frac{dr}{V}$. This value of p gives $d_x p = -\frac{dr}{V^2} d_x V = -\frac{dr}{V^3} \delta X$, and similarly $d_y p = -\frac{dr}{V^3} \delta Y, d_z p = -\frac{dr}{V^3} \delta Z$; whence

$$X', Y', Z' = X + \frac{dr}{V^2} \delta X, Y + \frac{dr}{V^2} \delta Y, Z + \frac{dr}{V^2} \delta Z,$$

which is as it should be, viz. these are what X, Y, Z become on substituting therein for x, y, z the values $x + p\alpha, y + p\beta, z + p\gamma$.

25. I return to the case where p is arbitrary, and I investigate the values of $a, b, \dots$ for the point P' on the vicinal surface; say these are $a', b', \&c.$, then we have $a' = d_{x'}X'$ &c. The relation between the differentials may be written

$$\begin{aligned} dx &= (1 - d_x p \alpha) dx' - d_y p \alpha dy' - d_z p \alpha dz', \\ dy &= -d_x p \beta dx' + (1 - d_y p \beta) dy' - d_z p \beta dz', \\ dz &= -d_x p \gamma dx' - d_y p \gamma dy' + (1 - d_z p \gamma) dz', \end{aligned}$$

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and we thence have $d_{x'} = (1 - d_x p \alpha) d_x - d_x p \beta d_y - d_x p \gamma d_z$ &c.; hence

$$\begin{aligned} a' &= \{(1 - d_x p \alpha) d_x - d_x p \beta d_y - d_x p \gamma d_z\} (X - V d_x p) \\ &= (1 - d_x p \alpha) a - d_x p \beta \cdot h - d_x p \gamma \cdot g - d_x (V d_x p) \\ &= a - p(ad_x \alpha + h d_x \beta + g d_x \gamma) - \frac{1}{V} \delta X d_x p - V d_x^2 p; \end{aligned}$$

and similarly, $f' = d_{y'}Z'$ (or $d_{z'}Y'$), that is

$$\begin{aligned} f' &= f - p(g d_y \alpha + f d_y \beta + c d_y \gamma) - (g \alpha + f \beta + c \gamma) d_y \\ &\quad - \frac{1}{V} \delta Y d_z p - V d_y d_z p. \end{aligned}$$

26. Completing the reduction, we find

$$\begin{aligned} a' &= a - p \left(\frac{a\omega - b - c}{V} - \frac{(\delta X)^2}{V^3} \right) - \frac{2}{V} \delta X d_x p - V d_x^2 p, \\ b' &= b - p \left(\frac{b\omega - c - a}{V} - \frac{(\delta Y)^2}{V^3} \right) - \frac{2}{V} \delta Y d_y p - V d_y^2 p, \\ c' &= c - p \left(\frac{c\omega - a - b}{V} - \frac{(\delta Z)^2}{V^3} \right) - \frac{2}{V} \delta Z d_z p - V d_z^2 p, \\ f' &= f - p \left(\frac{f\omega - f}{V} - \frac{\delta Y \delta Z}{V^3} \right) - \frac{1}{V} (\delta Y d_z p + \delta Z d_y p) - V d_y d_z p, \\ g' &= g - p \left(\frac{g\omega - g}{V} - \frac{\delta Z \delta X}{V^3} \right) - \frac{1}{V} (\delta Z d_x p + \delta X d_z p) - V d_z d_x p, \\ h' &= h - p \left(\frac{h\omega - h}{V} - \frac{\delta X \delta Y}{V^3} \right) - \frac{1}{V} (\delta X d_y p + \delta Y d_x p) - V d_x d_y p; \end{aligned}$$

say these expressions are $a' = a + \Delta a$, &c.

27. Taking ξ, η, ζ for the coordinates, referred to P as origin, of a point on the given surface near to P , and ξ', η', ζ' for the coordinates, referred to P' as origin, of the corresponding point on the vicinal surface, the relation between ξ', η', ζ' and ξ, η, ζ is the same as that between dx', dy', dz' and dx, dy, dz ; viz. we have

$$\begin{aligned} \xi' &= (1 - d_x p \alpha) \xi - d_y p \alpha \eta - d_z p \alpha \zeta, \\ \eta' &= -d_x p \beta \xi + (1 - d_y p \beta) \eta - d_z p \beta \zeta, \\ \zeta' &= -d_x p \gamma \xi - d_y p \gamma \eta + (1 - d_z p \gamma) \zeta. \end{aligned}$$

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or conversely

$$\begin{aligned}\xi' &= (1 + a_1)\alpha\xi + d_{12}\alpha\eta + d_{13}\alpha\zeta, \\ \eta' &= d_{21}\beta\xi + (1 + d_{22})\beta\eta + d_{23}\beta\zeta, \\ \zeta' &= d_{31}\gamma\xi + d_{32}\gamma\eta + (1 + d_{33})\gamma\zeta,\end{aligned}$$

say $\xi', \eta', \zeta' = \xi + \Delta\xi, \eta + \Delta\eta, \zeta + \Delta\zeta$; hence

$$\begin{aligned}X'\xi' + Y'\eta' + Z'\zeta' &= (X' - V d_1x)(\xi + \Delta\xi) + \&c. \\ &= X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta \\ &\quad + X\Delta\xi + Y\Delta\eta + Z\Delta\zeta \\ &\quad - V(d_1x\xi + \omega d_2y\eta + d_3z\zeta),\end{aligned}$$

where second line is

$$\begin{aligned}&(Xa + Y\beta + Z\gamma)(d_1x\xi + \omega d_2y\eta + d_3z\zeta) \\ &+ \mu\{X d_1y\eta + Y d_2y\xi + \&c.\} + (X\Delta_1\xi + Y\Delta_2\eta + Z\Delta_3\zeta) + \omega(X\Delta_2\xi + Y\Delta_3\eta + Z\Delta_1\zeta).\end{aligned}$$

But

$$\begin{aligned}X\Delta_1\alpha + Y\Delta_2\beta + Z\Delta_3\gamma &= \frac{\partial\Sigma}{\partial\xi} - V d_1X = 0, \\ X\Delta_2\alpha + Y\Delta_3\beta + Z\Delta_1\gamma &= 0, \\ X\Delta_3\alpha + Y\Delta_1\beta + Z\Delta_2\gamma &= 0,\end{aligned}$$

or second line is $= V(d_1x\xi + \omega d_2y\eta + d_3z\zeta)$; we have therefore

$$X'\xi' + Y'\eta' + Z'\zeta' = X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta;$$

We require

$$(A', B', C', F', G', H'\sim\xi', \eta', \zeta')^2;$$

viz. to the first order Δ , this is

$$\begin{aligned}&= (A, \dots \sim\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 \\ &+ 2(\Delta \dots \sim\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 + \&c. \&c.,\end{aligned}$$

28. Here second line is

$$2\{A\xi + B\eta + G\xi \Delta\xi + (H\xi + B\eta + F\xi)\Delta\eta + (G\xi + F\eta + C\xi)\Delta\zeta\}$$

but

$$H\xi + B\eta + G\zeta = B\eta - VH\xi$$

$$\begin{vmatrix} \alpha, & \beta, & \gamma \\ X, & Y, & Z \\ \xi, & \eta, & \zeta \end{vmatrix}$$

$$H\xi + B\eta + F\zeta = B\eta - VH\xi$$

$$\begin{vmatrix} \alpha, & \beta, & \gamma \\ X, & Y, & Z \\ \xi, & \eta, & \zeta \end{vmatrix}$$

$$G\xi + F\eta + C\zeta = VH\xi + Xh\eta$$

$$\begin{vmatrix} \alpha, & \beta, & \gamma \\ X, & Y, & Z \\ \xi, & \eta, & \zeta \end{vmatrix}$$

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whence term in $\{ \}$ is

$$\begin{vmatrix} d\xi \Delta\xi, & d\xi \Delta\eta \\ d\eta \Delta\xi, & d\eta \Delta\eta \\ X, & Y, & Z \end{vmatrix} + \text{a sum of similar terms,}$$

which might be written

$$\begin{vmatrix} d\xi, & d\eta, & d\zeta \\ \Delta\xi, & \Delta\eta, & \Delta\zeta \\ X, & Y, & Z \end{vmatrix} = \begin{vmatrix} \xi, & \eta, & \zeta \\ X, & Y, & Z \end{vmatrix}$$

but it is perhaps more convenient to retain the second term in its original form.

29. As regards the first line, we have

$$\begin{aligned} A &= BC' - F^2V \\ &= V(b + \Delta b)(F + V d_1h) - \{(g + V d_2g)(F - V d_3g)\} \\ &= A + V(\Delta_1b d_1h - 2 d_2g d_3g + 2gh\xi); \end{aligned}$$

with similar expressions for the other coefficients. Attending only to the terms of the first order, we then obtain

$$\begin{aligned} A &= A + 2(B \Delta_1b - Vgh) - 2V(d_1h\xi - gh\xi), \\ B &= B + 2(C \Delta_1c - Vfg) - 2V(d_2h\xi - gh\xi), \\ C &= C + 2(A \Delta_1a - Vfh) - 2V(d_3h\xi - gh\xi), \\ F &= F + V d_1\alpha - X d_2\alpha - Y(d_2c - \Delta\eta) - V(\xi d_1h\eta - gh\xi - gh\eta) + \xi h\eta, \\ G &= G + V d_1\beta - X d_1\alpha - V(\Delta b - \Delta\eta) - V(d_2h\xi - gh\xi - gh\eta) + gh\eta, \\ H &= H + X d_2\alpha - X d_1\beta - V(\Delta c - \Delta\xi) - V(d_3h\xi - fgh\xi - gh\eta) + gh\eta; \end{aligned}$$

my these are $A' = A + bA$, &c., where b is a functional symbol; we then have

$$(A' \dots \xi', \eta', \zeta')^2 = (A \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 + (bA \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 + 2(A \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)(\Delta\xi, \Delta\eta, \Delta\zeta);$$

which, for shortness, I represent by

$$(A \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 + (bA \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2,$$

and I proceed to complete the calculation of the coefficients A' , B' , &c.

30. We have

$$\begin{aligned} A' &= bA + \text{coeff. } b'^2 \text{ in} \\ &2\{B \Delta b + G\xi \Delta\eta + (H\xi + B\eta + F\xi)\Delta_1h + (G\eta + F\eta + C\xi)\Delta_3h\} \\ &= bA + 2\{aA\eta \Delta_1\alpha + 2gh\eta\eta\} \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$\begin{aligned} A' &= bA + \frac{2}{V}(AX + HY + GZ) d_1\alpha \\ &+ 2\eta(d_2b \Delta_2h + h\xi \Delta_3h) \end{aligned}$$

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where coeff. $b\eta$ is

$$\begin{aligned} &= \frac{A\eta + Hb + G\eta}{V} - \frac{(AX + HY + GZ)\eta\beta\eta}{V} \\ &= \frac{1}{V} \left\{ (a\alpha - p\beta) - p^2\alpha + (\gamma + b)\beta + (gg + Gh) d_2 \right\}. \end{aligned}$$

31. And similarly,

$$\begin{aligned} F' &= bF + V(\Delta a - \Delta\eta) + V d_2g + V d_3g + V(d_1\alpha + b\eta\xi h + gh\xi + h\eta\xi\xi h) d\eta_c d\eta_c\eta + d_3h d_c d_c\eta \\ &\quad + p(dXYh + ZV F d_1h) d\eta_c + (\xi h + gh) d_2 d\eta_c + (Xb + HY + FZ) d_2h d_c \\ &\quad - 6F d_1h - ph\xi - h(d_c\eta\eta\eta) d\eta, \end{aligned}$$

which gives the following formulæ; viz. on these lines

$$\begin{aligned} F' &= bF + V(\Delta_2 YZ - EXY) + \frac{1}{p} \left\{ p(XHX + GLY) d_c\eta_c - V d d_2 \right\} \\ &\quad - 2(VF d_1\alpha + V d d_c + V d d_c\eta + \&c) \\ &\quad + 2V(d_c\eta + V d d_c\eta) d_c\eta \\ &\quad - 2V(db\eta - p\xi) d_c\eta, \end{aligned}$$

which to denote in the foregoing equation, together with the following terms:

$$= \frac{1}{p}(\alpha A + V d \alpha) d_c\eta + 2(db\eta - p\xi) d_c\eta,$$

which destroy certain of the foregoing ones; viz. we have

$$A' = (b + \frac{2FHX}{V}) d_c\eta + 2(VH - VXY) d_c\eta.$$

32. Similarly, the value of bF is

$$\begin{aligned} bF &= V \left\{ -\frac{p}{V}(\alpha + h) + d_c\eta XY \right\} = \frac{1}{p} \left\{ V(YHX + LXY) d_c\eta - V d d\xi \right. \\ &\quad \left. - 2VY \left(\frac{1}{p} d_cp - p\beta \right) \xi d\eta + V d d\xi \right. \\ &\quad \left. - 2VY(d_c\eta - p\beta) - 2VY(d\xi - d_c\xi) d\eta + V d d\xi \right. \\ &\quad \left. + p dV d\xi \right. \\ &\quad \left. - p\xi d\eta d_c + p\xi d\eta, \right\} \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned} &= \frac{1}{p}(\alpha b\eta + Vh) \left[\frac{p}{V}(YHX - EXY) + \frac{FVHX}{V}(VHX - XHY) + \frac{p}{V}d\xi d\eta \right] \\ &\quad + \left\{ -\frac{1}{p}(B\xi + EXY + Vh - h) \right\} \eta d_c\eta \\ &\quad + \left\{ \frac{pX}{V} - \frac{2HY}{V} - Vh \right\} d\eta d_c\eta \\ &\quad + (VY d\xi + VX d\eta + VXH\eta - VXY)p \end{aligned}$$

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The value of θA is

$$\begin{aligned}\theta A &= 2E \left\{ -\frac{p}{V} (b\alpha + h) + \frac{1}{p} d_c EXY \right\} = \frac{1}{V} (2Vh\eta + LX\eta d\xi - Vd d\xi) \\ &\quad - 2VY \left\{ -\frac{p}{V} (b\eta + h) + \frac{1}{p} d_c \eta EXY \right\} = \frac{1}{V} (GBX + LX\eta d\xi - Vd d\xi) \\ &\quad - 2V(bh\xi - p\eta\xi),\end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned}&= \frac{p}{V} (2b\alpha + b\eta) + \frac{p}{V} (XY - YX) - \frac{pX}{V} (XY - EXY) \\ &\quad - \frac{2b\xi}{V} (BX - Vh) - 2V(b\eta d\xi - p\xi d\eta).\end{aligned}$$

Hence the value of A' is equal to the last-mentioned expression, together with the following terms:

$$= \frac{p}{V} (\alpha A + b\eta) + \frac{2XZ}{V} \left[(b\xi) d_c \eta + 2F(d\xi - YH) d\xi - V(d\xi - YX) d\eta \right]$$

which destroy certain of the foregoing ones; viz. we have here

$$A' = (\theta + \frac{2FHX}{V}) \xi d\xi + 2(VH - VXY) d\xi.$$

And similarly, the value of δF is

$$\begin{aligned}\delta F &= V \left\{ -\frac{p}{V} (b\alpha + h) + \frac{1}{p} d_c LXY \right\} d\xi (LH + EXY) d\xi = Vd d\xi \\ &\quad - 2 \left\{ \frac{p}{V} (LH + LH) + \frac{pLH}{V} \right\} d\xi d\eta + V(LEH - V) d\xi \\ &\quad - 2 \left\{ \frac{pXH}{V} - \frac{2HY}{V} - Vh \right\} d\xi d\eta - \frac{pH}{V} (Vh - LH) - Vh LH d\xi \\ &\quad - 2 \left\{ \frac{p}{V} - 2Vh \right\} d\xi d\eta - Vd h d\xi + VXY d\xi - VXY d\xi\end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned}&= \frac{p}{V} (2b\alpha - b\eta) + \frac{p}{V} (YHX - LXY) + \frac{pHY}{V} (YHX - XHY) \\ &\quad + \left\{ -\frac{1}{p} (\alpha LH + LXY) d\xi - Vh \right\} d\xi \\ &\quad + \left\{ \frac{pL}{V} (LH + LH) + 2Vh \right\} d\xi \\ &\quad + \left\{ \frac{pLH}{V} - LH \right\} d\eta \\ &\quad + \left\{ -VV d_c \eta + VBX d_c \eta + VX\eta d_c \eta - VH d_c \eta \right\} d\eta\end{aligned}$$

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Hence F' is equal to the foregoing expression, together with the following terms:

$$\begin{aligned} & + \frac{p}{V} \left(\beta A + \frac{2FHY}{V} \right) (XLE - EXY) - \frac{pHY}{V} (YXX - XXX) \\ & + \frac{p}{V} (\beta A - 2EXY) + \frac{p}{V} (XLE - EXY) \\ & + \frac{pHL}{V} (LH + GLY) d\xi + \frac{pL}{V} (LXE + LXY) d\eta, \end{aligned}$$

which destroy certain of the foregoing; viz. we then have

$$\begin{aligned} F' = bF + V(YE - EXY) + \frac{pHXY}{V} d\xi d\eta + \frac{p}{V} d\xi + V d\xi d\eta + \frac{HLXY}{V} d\xi \\ + VY d_c\eta d\eta + VHYH d_c\eta + VHYXH d_c\eta. \end{aligned}$$

34. We have here

$$A' = 2 \left(Yh - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) d\xi + 2 \left(Yh - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) d\xi + 2 \left(Yh - \frac{VHY}{V} \right) d\xi + 2V(Vh - XYh) d\xi + V(VY - VZ) d\xi$$

$$B' = -2 \left(Y - \frac{VHY}{V} \right) d\xi + 2 \left(Yh - \frac{VHY}{V} \right) d\xi + 2V(Vh - XYh) d\xi - VYh d\xi + EXYh d\xi$$

$$C' = -2 \left(Y - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) d\xi + 2 \left(Yh - \frac{VHY}{V} \right) d\xi + 2V(Yh - XYh) d\xi$$

$$F' = \left\{ V(h-1) + \frac{p}{V} (YE - LXY) d\xi + \left(Yh - \frac{VHY}{V} \right) d\xi + V(Vhh - LXY) d\xi d\eta \right\} - VY_a d\xi - 2bH d\xi - 2V(bX) d\xi$$

$$G' = \left(Yh - \frac{pXY}{V} \right) d\xi + \left\{ V(h-1) - \frac{1}{p} (YXH - EXY) d\xi \right\} + V(Vhh - VYh) d\xi + VY_a d\xi - 2bV d\xi - 2V(VX) d\xi$$

$$H' = \left(Yh - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) d\xi - \left(Yh - \frac{VYH}{V} \right) d\xi + V(h-1) - \frac{1}{V} (LXH - VXH) d\xi + V(VXVh - VVX) d\xi + V d\xi$$

35. It will be recollected that we have $X'\xi' + Y'\eta' + Z'\zeta' = X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta$; by what precedes it appears that for the given surface the principal tangents are determined by the equations

$$(A \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0,$$

$$X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0,$$

and that the lines which (in the tangent plane of the given surface) correspond to the principal tangents of the corresponding point of the wicinal surface are determined by the equations

$$(A \dots \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 + (\Delta \xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0,$$

$$X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0.$$

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Condition that the two surfaces may belong to an Orthogonal System.

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36. The condition in order that the two surfaces may belong to an orthogonal system is that the principal tangents shall correspond, or, what is the same thing, the lines which (in the tangent plane of the given surface) correspond to the principal tangents of the vicinal surface be the principal tangents of the given surface. When this is the case, the plane and now $X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0$, $(\Delta \dots \xi)^2 = 0$, $(\xi'\eta'\zeta')$ intersect in the principal tangent, and this is therefore the required condition.

The plane $X\xi + Y\eta + Z\zeta = 0$ meets the cone $(A \dots \xi)^2 = 0$ in the principal tangents, that is, in pair of lines harmonically related to the circular lines and also to the chief tangents. Forming the two coefficients (A') , (B') , (C') , (F') , (G') , (H') of these terms in the same way as (A) , &c. are formed from A , &c., they must therefore as it is the case for the chief tangents satisfy

$$(A')\xi^2 + (B')\eta^2 + (C')\zeta^2 = 0,$$

$$(F')\xi, \quad (G')\eta\xi, \quad \dots = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(A' \dots)\xi^2 = 0,$$

$$(A' \dots)(\dots)\xi^2 = 0.$$

The former of these, as about to be shown, is an identical identity; we have therefore the second of these, say $A' \dots$, &c. = 0 as the required condition.

37. We have

$$(A') + (B') + (C') = A + B + C + V^2 - (A \dots \xi X, Y, Z)^2,$$

$$B^2 + F^2 + C = (BC - F^2V)X^2 + \dots = V(XHYE\xi - XXHY)^2 - V(XX - HX)^2,$$

Forming next the expression of $A'X + B'Y + C'Z$, &c., and for convenience using down separately the terms which involve the second differentials of X , Y , Z , we have

$$\begin{aligned} A'X + B'Y + C'Z &= (AX + HY + GZ) d_1\alpha \\ &+ d_2\alpha V(YXY\alpha) - V(XBXY - VXYh) d\xi - V(XXY - YXYh - VXYVh) d\eta d\xi \\ &= V(XXYZH - VXYh)\xi \\ &- 2V(VHXXH - VXYVh - VX)\xi d\xi d\eta + (XXY - VXYh) d\eta d\xi \end{aligned}$$

where AV stands for $\frac{1}{V}(LX\xi + Vh\xi + VH)$, and so on, and where these expressions contain also the following terms respectively:

$$\begin{aligned} &-VZ d_c \bullet + (X d_1\alpha - p\xi)X d_c\eta + X d_c\eta d_c - VZ d_c\xi d_c\eta\eta \\ &+ ZE d_c\eta - p\xi d_c\eta + (\alpha - p\xi) d_c\eta + VX\xi d\xi d\eta d\xi \\ &+ XX d_c\eta + ZX d_c\eta + p\xi d_c\eta - VXY d_c\eta - V(dZ + Vp) d\xi \end{aligned}$$

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Multiplying by X, Y, Z and adding, the terms which contain the second differential coefficients disappear, and we obtain

$$(A' \dots X, Y, Z)^2 = V^2 \{BXY - YEZ\} d_c \alpha + (XKH - EZX) d_c \beta + (YKH - YHY) d_c \gamma \}$$

so that, attending to the above value of $A^2 + B^2 + C^2$, we have the required equation

$$(A' \dots) d_c X, Y, Z)^2 = 0.$$

38. Proceeding now to form the value of $(A' \dots)(\dots)$, that is,

$$A' (\xi \eta + B' \eta \beta + C' \zeta \beta + 2F' \eta \zeta + 2G' \zeta \xi + 2H' \xi \eta),$$

as regards those containing the first differential coefficients of ρ , namely of themselves; as regards those containing the second differential coefficients, forming the auxiliary equations

$$\begin{aligned} (A) &= 2(b)A - 2(g)V, \\ (B) &= 2(f)X - 2(h)V, \\ (C) &= 2(g)V - 2(f)Z, \\ (F) &= -(h)Y - (g)Z - (l)b + (c)Y, \\ (G) &= -(f)X - (g)Y + (l)b + (c)X, \\ (H) &= -(g)X - (f)Y + (h)b + (g)X, \end{aligned}$$

we find without difficulty that the terms in question (being, in fact, the complete value of the expression) are

$$= V(\xi A \dots d_a, d_b, d_c) \rho.$$

39. As regards the terms involving the first differential coefficients, observe that the whole coefficient of $b\rho$ is

$$\begin{aligned} &= 2(\xi) \left(Yh - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) \\ &+ 2(\xi) \left(Vg - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) \\ &+ 2(\xi) \left(V(h - h) - \frac{p}{V} (YXY - EXY) \right) \\ &+ 2(\xi) \left(Yh - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) \\ &+ 2(\xi) \left(Yg - \frac{VHX}{V} \right) \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\begin{aligned} &= 2V \left\{ (g)(\Delta + (g) + (l)b + (h)b + (l)f) \right\} b \\ &+ \frac{2}{V} (\Delta (\xi b) + (l) LX + (g) (LXH + (f) LX + (h) LX) \} b. \end{aligned}$$

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40. The reduction depends on the following auxiliary formulæ:

$$\begin{aligned} a(g\eta + h)\Delta + p(g\eta - YH - XLX)(\eta b) + (l)(\xi) + (l)\xi + (l)(\xi) &= -XEX, \\ l + g(\xi)h + (l)(\xi) &= -YEX, \\ a + b + (l) + \dots &= -ZLX, \\ b(\xi)k - q + V \dots &= -XEX, \\ y + g(\xi)h + (l)(\xi) &= -EXY, \\ g(\xi)k - q + V \dots &= -YEX, \end{aligned}$$

where, for shortness, I have written LX , LY , LZ to stand for $aX + gY + bZ$, $\xi X + bY + \xi Z$, $gX + \xi Y + gZ$ respectively, and YXY for $bX + YdZ$, $dZX + YdZ$ for $dX + dZ$, etc. etc. for dX , dY , dZ .

From these we immediately have

$$\begin{aligned} (\xi)LX + (l)LY + (h)LZ &= V(LX\eta - YEX), \\ (h)LX + (l)LY + (l)LZ &= V(LXdY - YEY), \\ (g)LX + (l)LY + (l)LZ &= V(LXdZ - YEZ), \end{aligned}$$

Hence, in the coefficient of $b\rho$, the first term is

$$= 2V(-YEX + YEX + YEX),$$

and the second line is

$$= \frac{1}{V}\{(VX(LX + \xi)LX) + 2V(VLX - VEX)(LX)\}.$$

so that the sum, or whole coefficient of $b\rho$, is $= 0$. Similarly, the coefficients of $b\rho$ and $\partial\rho$ are each $= 0$.

41. We have thus arrived at the equation

$$(A \dots \check{d}_a, d_b, d_c)\rho = 0$$

as the condition to be satisfied by the normal distance ρ in order that the given surface and the trivial surface may belong to an orthogonal system; viz. this is a partial differential equation of the second order, its coefficients being given functions of $X, Y, Z, a, b, c, f, g, h$, the first and second differential coefficients of z (where $z = z(x, y, z)$ is the equation of the given surface).

The equation, it is clear, may also be written in the two forms

$$(A \dots \check{d}_a Y_c Z_c, Yd_a, Zd_b, Xd_a \check{\rho})\rho = 0,$$

and

$$\left| \begin{array}{ccc} F^2 & G^2 & dXd_b \\ e\Gamma + bGd_c + phX + eGd_c fX & pd_1 + bhX & \frac{F^2}{V} \end{array} \right| \rho = 0,$$

if, for shortness, P, Q, R are written to denote $dZ_c - Yd_c d_c, Xd_a d_c, Yd_c d_c, X_a d_c$, respectively, it being understood that on each of these forms the d_a, d_b, d_c operate on the ρ only.

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Condition that a family of surfaces may belong to an Orthogonal System.

Art. Nos. 42 to 43.

42. We pass at once to the condition in order that the family of surfaces

$$v = c(x, y, z) = 0$$

may belong to an orthogonal system, viz. when the vicinal surface belongs to the family, we have ρ proportional to $\frac{1}{V} \left(= \frac{1}{\sqrt{X^2+Y^2+Z^2}} \right)$, and the condition is

$$(A \dots) d_a, d_b, d_c \frac{1}{V} = 0,$$

where v is a function of (x, y, z) , the first and second differential coefficients of which are A, B, C, F, G, H , and the equation is then a partial differential equation of the third order satisfied by v . The form is by no means an inconvenient one, but it admits of further reduction.

43. We have $d_a \frac{1}{V}, d_b \frac{1}{V}, d_c \frac{1}{V}$ equal to $-\frac{1}{V^2} aX, -\frac{1}{V^2} LY, -\frac{1}{V^2} LZ$ respectively, and thence

$$d_a \frac{1}{V} = -\frac{1}{V^2} (aX + b\xi + g\xi d_a \xi) + \frac{3X}{V^4} (LX),$$

$$d_c d_a \frac{1}{V} = -\frac{1}{V^2} (g\xi + h + f d_a \xi) d_c + \frac{3X}{V^4} LXY,$$

or, as these may be written,

$$d_a d_c \frac{1}{V} = -\frac{1}{V^2} (\xi a + b\xi + b\eta) d_c + \frac{3X}{V^4} (LX),$$

$$d_c d_c \frac{1}{V} = -\frac{1}{V^2} (g\xi + g\eta + g d_c) d_c \eta + \frac{3X}{V^4} LXY,$$

with the like values for $d_c \frac{1}{V}$, &c. Substituting, the equation contains a term multiplied by a , viz. this is

$$= -\frac{1}{V^2} (A \dots) d_c,$$

which vanishes; and a term multiplied by a , viz. this is

$$= \frac{6}{V^4} (LX + (\beta) + (\gamma)) V,$$

which also vanishes. Writing down the remaining terms, and multiplying the whole by $-V$, the equation becomes

$$(A \dots)(\xi), \dots \dots (\xi), \dots \dots = -\frac{1}{V^2} (A \dots LX, LY, LXY) = 0.$$

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44. The last term admits of reduction; from the equations

$$(A) = AV^2 + 2YXV - 2XYE, \text{ \&c., we find}$$

$$(A) LX + (H) LY + (G) LZ = (AbY + BLY + GLZ) + VPF(XBLY - YLZ),$$

$$(H) LX + (B) LY + (F) LZ = (HXY + BLY + FLZ) + VPF(YGLZ - ZLX),$$

$$(G) LX + (F) LY + (C) LZ = (GLX + FLY + CLZ) + VPF(YLZ - XLY),$$

and hence

$$(A \dots \sim LX, LY, LXY) = V^2 (A \dots \sim LX, LY, LZ),$$

wherefore the equation becomes

$$(A \dots \sim)(\xi), \dots \sim + 2 (A \dots \sim LX, LY, LZ) = 0.$$

45. It will be shown that we have identically

$$(A \dots \sim)(\xi), \dots \sim = -(A \dots \sim \xi X, \xi Y, \xi Z) \begin{vmatrix} LX, & XY, & LZ \\ X, & Y, & Z \\ LX, & LY, & LZ \end{vmatrix}.$$

The partial differential equation thus assumes the form

$$(A \dots \sim \xi) \dots = 0,$$

where Ω may be expressed indifferently in the three forms,

$$\begin{aligned} &= 4 (A \dots \sim \xi) \dots, \\ &= 4 (A \dots \sim LX, LY, LZ), \\ &= -4 \begin{vmatrix} LX, & LY, & LZ \\ X, & Y, & Z \\ LX, & LY, & LZ \end{vmatrix}. \end{aligned}$$

46. Taking the first of these, the partial differential equation is

$$(A \dots \sim \xi) \dots = 2 (A \dots) \sim \xi = 0,$$

or, written at full length, it is

$$\begin{aligned} &(A) ba + (B) bb + (C) bc + 2(F) bf + 2(G) bg + 2(H) bh \\ &- 2(A, \dots \sim LX, LY, LZ) + (A, \dots \sim ba, bb, bc, bf, bg, bh) = 0, \end{aligned}$$

where the coefficients are given functions of $X, Y, Z, a, b, c, f, g, h$, the first and second differential coefficients of v ; and it is written to denote $Xd_a + Yd_b + Zd_c$, that is, $bX = Xd_a X + Yd_b X + Zd_c X$, and similarly for the others bY, bZ .

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47. It remains to prove the above-mentioned identity.

To reduce the term $(A \dots \xi X, LY, LZ)^2$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} & A\xi X + HLY + GLZ \\ &= A(aX + bY + gZ) + H(bX + bY + fZ) + G(gX + fY + cZ) \\ &= X[a(LY^2 - F^2) + b(HY - GZ) + g(GE - YH)] \\ &\quad + Y[a(LY - YH) - b(LX - YH) + g(GE - YH)] \\ &\quad + Z[a(LX - GE) + b(LX - HX) - g(LX - YH)] \\ &= a(LV^2 - XYE) - b(LV^2 + ZEX) - g(LV^2 + YHY); \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$A\xi X + LV^2 + GLY = XV^2 - a(YEZ + ZLY) + b(ZLZ - XLX),$$

and similarly

$$HLX + BLY + FLZ = (YEZ - LXY) + V(a(XEX - XEY) + h(LX - LX)),$$

$$GLX + FLY + CLZ = -a(LX - LX) + V(a(XEY - YH) - g(LX - LX)),$$

whence

$$\begin{aligned} (A, B, C, F, G, H \dots LX, LY, LZ)^2 &= V^2(LX + YLY + ZLZ) \\ &\quad - 2(a(LY - LXY)(LXY - LXZ) + LXYh(LY - LXZ)), \end{aligned}$$

48. Now, from the equations $AX + HY + GZ = -V\xi$, &c., we have for the value of even the foregoing determinant

$$\begin{aligned} & \{2d\xi_c d\eta - 2bX d\eta bX + 2(b\eta)b(bX + aY d\xi)\}b \\ &= (BP + CY^2 - 2FYZ)X^2 \\ &\quad + (CX^2 + AZ^2 - 2GZX)Y^2 \\ &\quad + (AY^2 + BX^2 - 2HXY)Z^2 \\ &\quad + 2(-AYZ + FX^2 + GXY + HXZ)YZ \\ &\quad + 2(-BX^2Z + GY^2 + HYZ + FXY)ZX \\ &\quad + 2(-CXY + HZ^2 + FZX + GZY)XY, \end{aligned}$$

and subtracting therefrom the function $(A, \dots \dots)$, which is

$$\begin{aligned} &= (BP + CY^2 + (AB - F^2)X^2 \\ &\quad + (CY^2 + AB - F^2)Y^2 \\ &\quad + (AY^2 + BX^2 - H^2)Z^2 \\ &\quad - 2(FY^2 + HZ + EXY)YZ \\ &\quad - 2(GZ^2 + EX + EXY)ZX \\ &\quad - 2(HX^2 + FEZ + EXY)XY, \end{aligned}$$

the difference is found to be

$$\begin{aligned} &= a(L \dots \dots YZ, ZP + GLY + GLZ) \\ &\quad + b(L \dots \dots EX, X^2 + EXY) \\ &\quad + c(L \dots \dots XY, Y^2 + EXY) \\ &\quad - 2f(LX + BLY + GLZ)YZ \\ &\quad - 2g(LX + BLY + GLZ + bLY)ZX \\ &\quad - 2h(LX + GLY + HLY)XY. \end{aligned}$$

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which, on account of $(A \dots \sim \xi X, Y \sim LZ)^2 = 0$, and $A + B + C = 0$, reduces itself to

$$(A \dots \sim \dots) V.$$

49. We have

$$\begin{aligned} Aa + Bb + Cg &= a(BX - 2g)V \\ &+ b(gLY - fY - a(bh)) \\ &+ p(VZ - bLX - cbZ)Y \\ &= X(gb - bgy) \\ &+ V(gy - py - (pl + g + h + hh) + L LX \\ &+ Z(bn - h - (bh + b)b + ff)b), \end{aligned}$$

or, observing that in the coefficients of Y and Z the second terms each vanish, this is

$$Aa + Bb + Cg = X(bp - g)h + Y(ga - h)b + Z(\xi b - ha);$$

and similarly

$$Ha + Bb + Fg = X(gh - f) + Y(h - bh - c) + Z(\xi h - gg),$$

$$Gg + Fb + Cg = X(gh - g) + Y(gb - h)b + Z(gf - gg).$$

Adding these equations, the coefficient of X is the difference of two expressions each of which vanishes; and the like as regards the coefficients of Y and Z ; that is, we have

$$(A \dots \sim \dots) = 0,$$

and consequently

$$2 \begin{vmatrix} LX, & LY, & LZ \\ X, & Y, & Z \\ LX, & LY, & LZ \end{vmatrix} = (A \dots \sim \dots) = -(A \dots \sim \xi X, LY, LZ)^2,$$

the required relation.

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On the Centro-Surface of an Ellipsoid.

[From the *Transactions of the Cambridge Philosophical Society*, vol. XII. Part i. (1873), pp. 319–365. Read March 7, 1870.]

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THE centro-surface of any given surface is the locus of the centres of curvature of the given surface, or say it is the locus of the intersections of consecutive normals (the normals which intersect the normal at any particular point of the surface being those at the consecutive points along the two curves of curvature respectively which pass through the point on the surface). The terms, normal, centre of curvature, curve of curvature, may be understood in their ordinary sense, or in the generalised sense referring to the case where the Absolute (instead of being the imaginary circle at infinity) is any quadric surface whatever; viz. the normal at any point of a surface is here the line joining that point with the pole of the tangent plane in regard of the quadric surface called the Absolute; and of course the centre of curvature and curve of curvature refer to the normal so defined.

The question of the centro-surface of a quadric surface has been considered in the two points of view, viz. 1^o, when the term “normal,” &c., are used in the ordinary sense, and the equation of the quadric surface (assumed to be an ellipsoid) is taken to be

$$\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c} = 1;$$

2^o, when the Absolute is the surface $X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2 + W^2 = 0$; in the first of these by Salmon, *Quart. Math. Jour.*, t. IX. (1858), pp. 217–222 (1858), and in the second by Clebsch, *Crelle*, t. LXIII. pp. 64–107 (1862); see also Salmon’s *Solid Geometry*, Ed. Ed., 1865, pp. 148, 402, &c. In the present Memoir, as shown by the title, the quadric surface is taken to be an Ellipsoid; and the question is considered exclusively from the first point of view: the theory is further developed in various respects, and in particular as regards the nodal curves upon the centro-surface: the distinction of real and

[520] ON THE CENTRO-SURFACE OF AN ELLIPSOID

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imaginary is of course attended to. The new results suitably modified would be applicable to the theory treated from the second point of view; but I do not on the present occasion attempt so to present them.

The Ellipsoid; Parameters ξ, η , &c. Art. Nos. 1–6.

1. The position of a point (X, Y, Z) on the ellipsoid

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2} = 1$$

may be determined by means of the parameters, or elliptic coordinates, ξ, η : viz. these are such that we have

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \xi} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \xi} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \xi} = 1, \quad \frac{X^2}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \eta} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \eta} = 1,$$

or, what is the same thing, ξ, η are the roots of the quadric equation

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + v} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + v} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + v} = 1.$$

(In its actual form this is a cubic equation, but there is a root $v = 0$, which is to be thrown out, and the quadric equation is thus

$$v^2 + (a^2 + b^2 + c^2 - X^2 - Y^2 - Z^2)v + \{b^2c^2 + c^2a^2 + a^2b^2 - (b^2 + c^2)X^2 - (c^2 + a^2)Y^2 - (a^2 + b^2)Z^2\} = 0,$$

or putting

$$P = a^2 + b^2 + c^2, \quad Q = b^2c^2 + c^2a^2 + a^2b^2, \quad R = a^2b^2c^2,$$

the equation is

$$v^2 + (P - X^2 - Y^2 - Z^2)v + Q - (b^2 + c^2)X^2 - (c^2 + a^2)Y^2 - (a^2 + b^2)Z^2 = 0.)$$

2. It is convenient to write throughout

$$\begin{aligned} \alpha &= b^2 - c^2, \\ \beta &= c^2 - a^2, \\ \gamma &= a^2 - b^2. \end{aligned}$$

(whence $\alpha + \beta + \gamma = 0$).

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As usual, a is taken to be the greatest and c the least of the semi-axes; we have thus α, γ each of them positive, and β negative, $= -\beta'$, where β' is a positive quantity $= \alpha + \gamma$. A distinction arises in the sequel between the two cases $a^2 + c^2 > 2b^2$ and $a^2 + c^2 < 2b^2$, but the two cases are not essentially different, and it is convenient to assume $a^2 + c^2 > 2b^2$, that is, $a^2 - b^2 > b^2 - c^2$, or $\gamma > \alpha$, say $\gamma - \alpha$ positive. The limiting case $a^2 + c^2 = 2b^2$, or $\gamma = \alpha$, requires special consideration.

3. We have

$$\begin{aligned} -\beta\gamma X^2 &= a^2(a^2 + \xi)(a^2 + \eta), \\ -\gamma\alpha Y^2 &= b^2(b^2 + \xi)(b^2 + \eta), \\ -\alpha\beta Z^2 &= c^2(c^2 + \xi)(c^2 + \eta). \end{aligned}$$

It is in fact easy to verify that these values satisfy as well the equation of the ellipsoid as the assumed equations defining the elliptic coordinates ξ, η . We may also obtain the relations

$$X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2 = a^2 + b^2 + c^2 + \xi + \eta,$$

$$a^2 X^2 + b^2 Y^2 + c^2 Z^2 = a^4 + b^4 + c^4 + b^2 c^2 + c^2 a^2 + a^2 b^2 + (a^2 + b^2 + c^2)(\xi + \eta) + \xi\eta.$$

These, however, are obtained more readily from the equation in v , viz. the roots thereof being ξ, η , we have

$$\begin{aligned} -\xi - \eta &= a^2 + b^2 + c^2 - X^2 - Y^2 - Z^2, \\ \xi\eta &= b^2 c^2 + c^2 a^2 + a^2 b^2 - (b^2 + c^2)X^2 - (c^2 + a^2)Y^2 - (a^2 + b^2)Z^2, \end{aligned}$$

which lead at once to the relations in question.

4. Considering ξ as constant, the locus of the point (X, Y, Z) is the intersection of the ellipsoid with the confocal ellipsoid

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \xi} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \xi} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \xi} = 1;$$

viz. this is one of the curves of curvature through the point; and similarly considering η as constant, the locus of the point is the intersection of the ellipsoid with the confocal ellipsoid

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \eta} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \eta} = 1;$$

viz. this is the other of the curves of curvature through the point.

5. If instead of ξ and η we write h and k , we may consider h as extending between the values $-a^2, -b^2$, and k as extending between the values $-b^2, -c^2$.

$h = \text{const.}$ will thus give the series of curves of curvature one of which is the section by the plane $X = 0$, or ellipse semi-axes b, c ; say this is the minor-mean series. In particular $h = -a^2$ gives the ellipse just referred to; and $h = -b^2$, or say $h = -b^2 - \epsilon$, gives two detached portions of the ellipse semi-axes a, c ; viz. each of these portions extends from an umbilicus above the plane of xy , through the extremity of the semi-axis a , to an umbilicus below the plane of xy .

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And in like manner $k = \text{const.}$ gives the series of curves of curvature one of which is the section by the plane $Z = 0$, or ellipse semi-axes a, b ; say this is the major-mean series. In particular $k = -c^2$ gives the ellipse just referred to; and $k = -b^2$, or say $k = -b^2 + \epsilon$, gives the remaining portions of the ellipse semi-axes a, c ; viz. these are two portions each extending from an umbilicus above the plane of xy , through the extremity of the semi-axis c , to an umbilicus above the plane of xy .

The ellipse last referred to may be called the umbilicar section, the other two principal sections being the major-mean section and the minor-mean section respectively.

In the limiting case $h = k = -b^2$, we have the umbilici, viz. these are given by

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2} = \frac{\alpha}{-\beta}, \quad Y = 0, \quad \frac{Z^2}{c^2} = \frac{\gamma}{-\beta}.$$

The two series of curves of curvature cover the whole real surface of the ellipsoid; so that at any real point thereof we have $\xi = h, \eta = k$, or else $\xi = k, \eta = h$, where h, k are negative real values lying within the foregoing limits $-a^2, -b^2$ and $-b^2, -c^2$ respectively. But observe that ξ, η taken separately may each extend between the limits $-a^2, -c^2$.

6. Suppose $\xi = \eta$, the equation in v will have equal roots, or the condition is

$$(P - X^2 - Y^2 - Z^2)^2 = 4\{Q - (b^2 + c^2)X^2 - (c^2 + a^2)Y^2 - (a^2 + b^2)Z^2\};$$

viz. this surface by its intersection with the ellipsoid determines the envelope of the curves of curvature. This envelope is in fact a system of eight imaginary lines, four of them belonging to one of the systems of right lines on the ellipsoid, the other four to the other of the systems of right lines. For in the values of X^2, Y^2, Z^2 writing $\eta = \xi$, we find

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{\sqrt{-\beta\gamma} X}{a(a^2 + \xi)} &= \pm 1, \\ \frac{\sqrt{-\gamma\alpha} Y}{b(b^2 + \xi)} &= \pm 1, \\ \frac{\sqrt{-\alpha\beta} Z}{c(c^2 + \xi)} &= \pm 1, \end{aligned}$$

or, representing for shortness the left-hand functions by $\pm X', \pm Y', \pm Z'$, the eight lines are

$$\begin{aligned} a^2 + \xi &= X' = Y' = Z', & a^2 + \xi &= X' = -Y' = -Z', \\ a^2 + \xi &= -X' = Y' = -Z', & a^2 + \xi &= -X' = -Y' = Z', \end{aligned}$$

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so that in the two tetrads each line intersects the four lines of the other tetrad, but it does not intersect the remaining three lines of its own tetrad. The intersections are four points corresponding to $\xi = -a^2$, being the imaginary umbilici in the plane $X = 0$; four to $\xi = -b^2$, being the real umbilici in the plane $Y = 0$; four to $\xi = -c^2$, being the imaginary umbilici in the plane $Z = 0$; and four corresponding to $\xi = \infty$, which may be called the umbilici at infinity.

Sequential and Concomitant Centro-curves. Art. No. 7.

7. Consider any particular curve of curvature; the normals at the several points thereof successively intersect each other in a series of points forming a curve; and we have thus, corresponding to the particular curve of curvature, a curve on the centro-surface, which curve may be called the sequential centro-curve. Again the same normals, viz. those at the several points of the particular curve of curvature, are intersected, the normal at each point by the consecutive normal belonging to the other curve of curvature through that point; and we have thus, corresponding to the particular curve of curvature, a curve on the centre-surface, which curve may be called the concomitant centro-curve. If instead of a single curve of curvature we consider the whole series, say of the major-mean curves of curvature, we have a series of major-mean sequential centro-curves, and also a series of major-mean concomitant centre-curves; and similarly considering the series of the minor-mean curves of curvature we have a series of minor-mean sequential centro-curves and also a series of minor-mean concomitant curves; the configuration of the several curves will be discussed further on, but it may be convenient to remark here that the centre-surface may be considered as consisting of two portions, say,

(A) locus of the major-mean sequential centro-curves; and also of the minor-mean concomitant centro-curves;

(B) locus of the minor-mean sequential centro-curves, and also of the major-mean concomitant centro-curves.

Investigation of expressions for the Coordinates of a point on the Centro-surface. Art. Nos. 8 to 13.

8. Consider the normal at the point (X, Y, Z) . Taking in the first instance (x, y, z) as current coordinates, the equations are

$$\frac{x - X}{\frac{X}{a}} = \frac{y - Y}{\frac{Y}{b}} = \frac{z - Z}{\frac{Z}{c}} = \lambda \text{ suppose.}$$

¹ According to Salmon, *Solid Geometry*, [Ed. 2, 1865], p. 210, the number of umbilici is a surface of the n th order is $= n(10n^2 - 15n + 6)$, viz. for $n = 2$, $= 14$, or it is, in the ordinary theory, and recognising the umbilici at infinity. For surfaces properly umbilici or not, the 4 points which I call the umbilici at infinity in the present theory dimension themselves in like manner with the 12 ordinary umbilici.

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or, what is the same thing,

$$x = X \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{a}\right), \quad y = Y \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{b}\right), \quad z = Z \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{c}\right).$$

Suppose now that the normal meets the consecutive normal, or normal at the point $X + dX, Y + dY, Z + dZ$; and let x, y, z belong to the point of intersection of the two normals; we have

$$0 = dX \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{a}\right) + \frac{X}{a} d\lambda,$$

$$0 = dY \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{b}\right) + \frac{Y}{b} d\lambda,$$

$$0 = dZ \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{c}\right) + \frac{Z}{c} d\lambda;$$

which determine the direction of the consecutive point; the equations in fact give

$$0 = \begin{vmatrix} dX, & \frac{X}{a}, \\ dY, & \frac{Y}{b}, \\ dZ, & \frac{Z}{c} \end{vmatrix},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$0 = \begin{vmatrix} dX, & dY, & dZ, \\ bcX, & caY, & abZ \end{vmatrix},$$

which is the differential equation of the curve of curvature. This equation must therefore be satisfied by taking for $X + dX, Y + dY, Z + dZ$ the coordinates of the consecutive point along either of the curves of curvature,—say along that which is the intersection with the surface

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \eta} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \eta} = 1.$$

9. To verify this, observe that we then have

$$\frac{XdX}{a^2} + \frac{YdY}{b^2} + \frac{ZdZ}{c^2} = 0,$$

$$\frac{XdX}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{YdY}{b^2 + \eta} + \frac{ZdZ}{c^2 + \eta} = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$XdX : YdY : ZdZ = a^2(a^2 + \eta)\beta : b^2(b^2 + \eta)\gamma : c^2(c^2 + \eta)a,$$

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But from the equations $-\beta\gamma X^2 = a^2(a^2 + \xi)(a^2 + \eta)$, etc., these become

$$XdX : YdY : ZdZ = \frac{X^2}{a^2+\xi} : \frac{Y^2}{b^2+\xi} : \frac{Z^2}{c^2+\xi};$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$dX : dY : dZ = \frac{X}{a^2+\xi} : \frac{Y}{b^2+\xi} : \frac{Z}{c^2+\xi};$$

and, substituting these values in the determinant equation, it becomes

$$0 = \begin{vmatrix} \frac{X}{a^2+\xi} & \frac{Y}{b^2+\xi} & \frac{Z}{c^2+\xi} \\ \frac{X}{a} & \frac{Y}{b} & \frac{Z}{c} \\ bcX, & caY, & abZ \end{vmatrix},$$

which is identically true, since evidently the determinant vanishes.

10. Proceeding with the solution, we have from the three equations

$$XdX + YdY + ZdZ = d\lambda \left(\frac{X^2}{a^2} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2} \right) + d\lambda \left(\frac{X^2}{a^2} \frac{1}{a^2} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2} \frac{1}{b^2} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2} \frac{1}{c^2} \right) = 0,$$

and observing that from the equation

$$X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2 = a + b + c + \xi + \eta,$$

considering therein η as constant, we have

$$XdX + YdY + ZdZ = \frac{1}{2}d\xi,$$

the equation becomes

$$\frac{1}{2}d\xi + d\lambda = 0;$$

and the three equations then are

$$0 = dX \left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{a} \right) - \frac{X}{2a} d\xi, \text{ etc.},$$

or say

$$0 = dX(a + \lambda) - \frac{1}{2}Xd\xi, \text{ etc.}$$

But from the equation $-\beta\gamma X^2 = a^2(a^2 + \xi)(a^2 + \eta)$, considering therein η as a constant, we have

$$\frac{dX}{X} = \frac{1}{2} \frac{d\xi}{a + \xi},$$

and the equations then become

$$0 = \frac{a+\lambda}{a+\xi} - 1, \text{ etc.},$$

viz. these are all satisfied if only $\lambda = \xi$.

11. The coordinates of the point of intersection of the two normals thus are

$$x = X \left(1 + \frac{\xi}{a} \right), \quad y = Y \left(1 + \frac{\xi}{b} \right), \quad z = Z \left(1 + \frac{\xi}{c} \right).$$

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or squaring, and substituting for X^2 , etc., their values as given by

$$-\beta\gamma X^2 = a^2(a^2 + \xi)(a^2 + \eta), \text{ etc.},$$

the equations become

$$-\beta\gamma x^2 = a^2(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta), \text{ etc.},$$

$$-\gamma ay^2 = b(b + \xi)^3(b + \eta), \text{ etc.},$$

$$-a\beta z^2 = c(c + \xi)^3(c + \eta), \text{ etc.};$$

viz. these equations give (x, y, z) the coordinates of a point on the centro-surface, the intersection of the normal at the point (X, Y, Z) of the ellipsoid, (determined by the parameters ξ, η), by the normal at the consecutive point along the curve of curvature

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \eta} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \eta} = 1.$$

Of course by interchanging ξ and η , we should obtain the coordinates of the point of intersection of the normal at the same point (X, Y, Z) by the normal at the consecutive point along the other curve of curvature

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \xi} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \xi} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \xi} = 1.$$

12. I stop for a moment to consider the foregoing two equations

$$\lambda = \xi, \quad d\lambda = -\frac{1}{2}d\xi.$$

which at first sight appear inconsistent. But observe that in the foregoing solution λ is the parameter of the point (x, y, z) of the centro-surface considered as a point on the normal at (X, Y, Z) ; $\lambda + d\lambda$ is the parameter of the same point considered as a point on the normal at the consecutive point $(X + dX, Y + dY, Z + dZ)$; the value $\lambda + d\lambda = \xi - \frac{1}{2}d\xi$ would belong to a different point, viz. the consecutive point of the centro-surface considered as a point on the consecutive normal: whence the $d\lambda$ of the solution ought not to be $= d\xi$. In further explanation, observe that the equations

$$x = X\left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{a}\right), \text{ etc.}, \quad \lambda = \xi,$$

if we pass from (x, y, z) to its consecutive point on the centro-surface, give

$$dx = dX\left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{a}\right) + \frac{X}{a}d\lambda,$$

but since by the equations

$$0 = dX\left(1 + \frac{\lambda}{a}\right) + \frac{X}{a}d\lambda,$$

this is

$$dx = \frac{X}{a}d\xi - \frac{X}{a}d\lambda,$$

¹ The expressions are given in effect, but not explicitly, Salmon, p. 149.

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Or since

$$a' = \lambda = \xi \quad (a + \xi),$$

this is

$$\frac{dx}{x} = \frac{1}{a+\xi} d\xi,$$

and similarly

$$\frac{dy}{y} = \frac{1}{b+\xi} d\xi, \quad \frac{dz}{z} = \frac{1}{c+\xi} d\xi,$$

which are the correct values of dx, dy, dz as derived from the equations

$$-\beta\gamma x^2 = a^2(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta), \text{ etc.,}$$

so that taking η at pleasure and considering η as denoting this function of ξ , the values of ξ, η belonging to a point on the nodal curve are $\xi = a^2(a + \beta)$, $\xi = c(a + \beta)c$; and the value of η is then given as before.

13. The form just given is analytically the most convenient, but there is some advantage in writing $\frac{1}{a+\xi}, \frac{1}{a+\eta}$ in the place of a, η respectively; viz. we then have expressions for the coordinates (x, y, z) of the centro-surface in terms of the coordinates (x, y, z) on the centro-surface, and writing for shortness f for the elimination of (ξ, η) from these expressions will therefore lead to the equation of the centro-surface.

Discussion by means of the equations $-\beta\gamma x^2 = a^2(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta)$, etc., Principal Sections, etc. Art. Nos. 14 to 24 (general subheading).

14. To fix the ideas consider the section of the surface by the plane $z = 0$; we have in the surface $z = 0$, that is, $\xi = -c^2$, or else $\eta = -c^2$, values which give respectively

$$\begin{aligned} -\beta\gamma x^2 &= a(a - c)^3(a - c), & -\beta\gamma x^2 &= a^2(a^2 - c^2)^3 a, \\ -\gamma ay^2 &= b(b - c)^3(b - c), & \text{or } -\gamma ay^2 &= b^2(b^2 - c^2)^3 b, \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{x^2}{(a-c)^3} &= \frac{a}{-\beta\gamma} (a + \eta), & \frac{x^2}{(a^2-c^2)^3} &= \frac{a}{-\beta\gamma} (a + \xi), \\ \frac{y^2}{(b-c)^3} &= \frac{b}{-\alpha\gamma} (b + \eta), & \frac{y^2}{(b^2-c^2)^3} &= \frac{b}{-\alpha\gamma} (b + \xi). \end{aligned}$$

The first set of equations gives

$$\frac{a^2 x^2}{(a - c)^3} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(b - c)^3} = 1,$$

which is the equation of an ellipse.

The second set of equations gives

$$(ax^2 + by^2)^2 = 2(a^2 b^2 c^2 ay^2)(bx^2 + ay^2),$$

which is the equation of an evolute of an ellipse.

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15. The ellipse $\frac{a^2x^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{b^2y^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1$ is a cuspidal curve on the surface, and the section by the plane $z = 0$ is consequently made up of this ellipse counted three times, and of the evolute; it is therefore of the twelfth order; and the order of the surface is in fact = 12.

It is clear that the section of the centro-surface arises from the section $\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} = 1$ viz. the normal at any point of this ellipse lies in the plane $Z = 0$; the latter section being by a normal at the consecutive point of the other curve of curvature gives a point on the ellipse $\frac{a^2x^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{b^2y^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1$, which ellipse is therefore the concomitant centro-curve. Observe that this other curve of curvature cuts the ellipse $\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} = 1$ at right angles, and that the normals at the consecutive points about meet in the same point on the ellipse $\frac{a^2x^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{b^2y^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1$; this shows that the last-mentioned ellipse is a cuspidal curve on the centro-surface.

16. The three principal sections of the centro-surface are consequently

$$\begin{aligned} z = 0, \quad & \frac{a^2x^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{b^2y^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1, \quad \text{and} \quad (ax^2)^2 = (bx^2)^2, \\ y = 0, \quad & \frac{a^2x^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{c^2z^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1, \quad \text{and} \quad (ax^2)^2 = (cz^2)^2, \\ x = 0, \quad & \frac{b^2y^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{c^2z^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1, \quad \text{and} \quad (by^2)^2 = (cz^2)^2; \end{aligned}$$

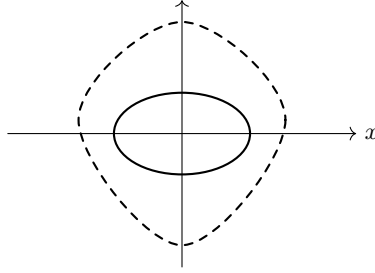
viz. each section is made up of an ellipse counting three times and of an evolute of an ellipse. The figure for shortness represented the three evolutes by their principal cusps it of the like character.

17. Considering only the positive directions of the axes, we have on each axis two points, viz.

$$\begin{array}{lll} \text{axis of } x & x = \frac{a-c}{a}, & x = \frac{a-b}{a}; \\ \text{axis of } y & y = \frac{b-c}{b}, & y = \frac{a-b}{b}; \\ \text{axis of } z & z = \frac{b-c}{c}, & z = \frac{a-c}{c}; \end{array}$$

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through each of which, in the two different planes passes through the axis respectively, there passes an ellipse and an evolute. In the second case $a + \beta > 2b'$, the disposition of the points is as shown in the figure.



principal-section disposition of ellipse and evolute

Plane of xz , evolute is outside ellipse:

yz , inside;

xy , cuts.

but in the contrary case $a + \beta < 2b'$, the disposition is

Plane of xz , evolute is outside ellipse:

yz , cuts;

xy , inside;

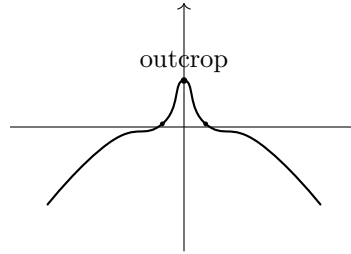
there is no real difference, and to fix the ideas I attend exclusively to the first-mentioned case

$$a + \beta > 2b'.$$

18. In each of the principal planes, the evolute and ellipse, qua curves of the orders 6 and 2 respectively, intersect in twelve points, 2 in each quadrant; viz. of the 3 points two unite together into a twofold point or point of contact, and the third is a point of simple intersection; assuming for the moment that this is so, the figure at once shows that in the plane of xy or unilinear plane the contact is real, the intersection imaginary; in the plane of yz , or major-mean plane, the contact is imaginary, the intersection real; but in the plane of xz or minor-mean plane the contact and intersection are each imaginary. The contacts are, as will appear later, the umbilici of the centro-surface; thus the same name "umbilicus centres," or "umbilicus", the simple intersections "points of outcrop," or simply "outcrop." By what precedes there are real umbilici, and the case the umbilicus (or each quadrant one); and in the major-mean plane four real outcrops (in each quadrant one); the other umbilicar centres and outcrops are respectively imaginary.

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19. The surface consists of two sheets intersecting in a nodal curve connecting the outcrop with the umbilicar centres. As to the form of this curve there is a cusp at the outcrop, and the curve does not terminate at the umbilicar centre but, on passing it, from crunodal becomes acnodal (viz. there is no longer through the curve any real sheet of the surface); moreover the curve is not at the umbilicar centre



nodal branch with cusp and umbilicar passage

perpendicular to the plane of xy , say there is consequently on the opposite side of the plane a symmetrically situate branch of the curve, viz. the umbilicar centre is a node on the nodal curve. Completing the curve, the nodal curve consists of two distinct portions; one on the positive side of the plane of yz or minor-mean plane consisting of two cuspidal branches as shown in the figure; the other a symmetrically situate portion on the negative side of the minor-mean plane.

Intersections of Evolute and Ellipse.

20. Consider it the plane of xy the ellipse and evolute,

$$\frac{a^2 x^2}{(a-c)^3} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(b-c)^3} = 1, \quad (ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2 - c^2(a^2 y^2 + b^2 x^2)y^2 = 0.$$

First, these are satisfied by

$$a^2 x^2 = -\frac{a^2}{-\beta\gamma}(b^2 + \gamma)^3, \quad b^2 y^2 = -\frac{b^2}{-\gamma a}(a^2 + \gamma)^3;$$

viz. the equations respectively become

$$\frac{-(\beta^2 + \gamma)^3}{-\beta\gamma} + \frac{(-a^2 + \gamma)^3}{-\gamma a} = 2(a + \beta)c.$$

The first of which is $a + \beta + \alpha\gamma + \beta\gamma$, and the second is

$$\sqrt{1}\{a^2(c - \beta)^3 + 2c\sqrt{\gamma a}\sqrt{-\beta\gamma(a - \beta + b)^3} + 4(c - \beta)^3\} = 0.$$

But the equation in $\sqrt{1}\{a^2(c - \beta)^3 + 2c(a^3 + b^3)\sqrt{-\beta\gamma} + \dots\} = 0$, or, what is the same thing,

$$(a^2 - \beta^2)(a^2 b^2 + 2ac\gamma + \dots)^2 - 4ay^2 z^2 (a + \beta)^3 + 2c(a^2 - \beta^2) \dots = 0.$$

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and substituting the foregoing values, this is

$$(a^2 - \beta^2) \left\{ \frac{a^2 + \beta^2}{\gamma} a^2 \gamma^3 - a^2 \beta^3 \gamma \right\} + 8\gamma^2 (\beta + \gamma) (a^2 + \gamma)^2 - 8a\beta\gamma^3 = 0,$$

that is,

$$\frac{1}{\gamma} a\beta^3 (a^2 + \beta^2) (a + \beta + \gamma) (a + \beta) = 0,$$

which, putting therein $a + \beta + \gamma = a$, and $a^2 + \beta^2 + a^2 + a^2 - 2a\beta\gamma$, is satisfied; that is, in the points on points or points of contact of the values and evolute.

21. Secondly, consider the values

$$\begin{aligned} a^2 x^2 &= \frac{a}{-\beta\gamma} \left(\frac{(y-a)^3}{\gamma-a} \right) \text{ (Coordinates of outcrops in plane of } xy \text{ (real).)}, \\ b^2 y^2 &= \frac{b}{-\gamma a} \left(\frac{(\beta-a)^3}{\gamma-\beta} \right); \end{aligned}$$

Substituting in the equation of the ellipse, we have

$$\frac{a(\beta-a)^3 + \beta\gamma a(\gamma-\beta)(a+\beta+\gamma)}{(\gamma-a)(\gamma-\beta)} = 1,$$

which is satisfied identically; and substituting in the equation of the evolute, we have first

$$a^2 x^2 + b^2 y^2 = -\frac{a^2(\beta-a)^3 + b^3(\gamma-a)(a+\beta-a)}{\gamma a(\gamma-a)} = 0,$$

or the equation is satisfied identically: and substituting in the equation of the evolute, we have

$$\sqrt{a^2(a-\beta)^3\beta^3c^2 + 2a\gamma a(\gamma-\beta)^3(a+\beta-\gamma)} - \sqrt{\gamma a} \sqrt{a^2(\gamma-\beta)^3(\gamma-a)} = 0,$$

and thus, in virtue of $a(\beta-a) + \beta(\gamma-a) + \gamma(a+\beta) = 0$ becomes

$$-\frac{3a\beta(\beta-\gamma)(\gamma-\beta) + b(\beta-a)(\gamma-a)}{\gamma a(\gamma-a)} = -\frac{3a(\beta-\gamma)(\gamma-a)}{a(\gamma-a)},$$

and thus, completing the substitution, it is seen that the equation of the evolute is also satisfied. The points last considered are simple intersections, and we have thus the complete number $(3 + 4, = 12)$ of the intersections of the evolute and ellipse.

22. We have a, η positive, β negative; whence $a - \beta$ can positive, $\beta - \gamma$ negative; $\gamma - a, = \beta - \beta'$, also positive; and hence, the outcrops on the plane of xy are real; the umbilicus centres are imaginary for this plane, but real for the plane of yz as appears next being

$$a^2 x^2 = -\frac{a^2}{-\beta\gamma} b^3, \quad \text{Coordinates of Umbilicus centres in plane of } xy \text{ (real).}$$

$$b^2 y^2 = \dots$$

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Nodes of the Evolute.

23. The Evolute is a curve with four nodes, all of them imaginary; viz. for the evolute in the plane of xy , the equation of which is

$$(ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2 - c^2(a^2y^2 + b^2x^2)y^2 = 0,$$

these are

$$a^2x^2 = -y^3, \quad b^2y^2 = -x^3, \quad \text{Coordinates of Nodes of evolute in plane of } xy \text{ (imaginary),}$$

in fact these values satisfy as well the equation of the evolute, as the two derived equations

$$6a^2x^2[c^2(a^2 + b^2y^2)^2] = bcy^2(a^2 + b^2y^2) = 0,$$

$$6b^2y^2[c^2(a^2 + b^2y^2)^2] = acx^2(a^2 + b^2y^2) = 0;$$

or its points in question are nodes of the evolute.

The evolute has the four cusps on the axes and two cusps at infinity, in all 8 cusps as just remarked; it has 4 nodes; and the order being 6, the class is

$$30 - 2 \cdot 4 = 8 \cdot 6 = 4.$$

Section by the plane infinity.

24. The surface itself is finite, and the section by the plane infinity is therefore imaginary; but by what precedes the nodal curve has nodal points at infinity, viz. there must be real acnodal points on this imaginary section. The section by the plane infinity resembles in fact the principal sections; viz. writing successively $\xi = \infty$, and $\eta = \infty$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} -\beta\gamma x^2 &= a\eta^4(\eta + a), & -\beta\gamma x^2 &= a\xi^4(\xi + a), \\ -\gamma ay^2 &= b\eta^4(\eta + b), & \text{or } -\gamma ay^2 &= b\xi^4(\xi + b), \\ -a\beta z^2 &= c\eta^4(\eta + c), & -a\beta z^2 &= c\xi^4(\xi + c); \end{aligned}$$

giving respectively

$$a^2x^2 + b^2y^2 + c^2z^2 = \eta^4, \quad (ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2 + (cz^2)^2 = \xi^4,$$

where the first equation represents an imaginary conic which counts three times; and the second equation, the rationalised form of which is

$$(a^2b^2c^2)^2 + (b^2c^2a^2)^2 + (c^2a^2b^2)^2 - 2a^2b^2c^2(a^2y^2 + b^2z^2 + c^2x^2)z^2 + 8abc \cdot abc \cdot abc \cdot y^2z^2 = 0,$$

is an imaginary evolute. The conic and evolute have four contacts and four simple intersections (in all $4 \cdot 2 + 4 = 12$ intersections) which are all of them imaginary. But the evolute has four real nodes (analogue of $ax^2 = -y^3$, etc.), which are repeating but being also by what precedes, the tangent of the evolute at that point, which point is also a node on the surface.

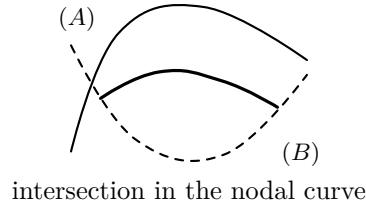
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a^2, y^2, z^2 , the lines in question will be not surely parallel to, but will be, the asymptotes of the nodal curve.

The plane infinity may be reckoned as a principal plane, and we may regard it in each of the four principal planes there are four umbilicar centres, four outcrops, and four evolute-nodes.

The generation of the surface considered geometrically.

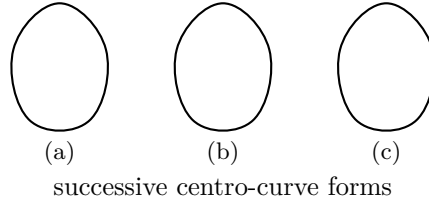
25. I have deferred until late the discussion of the generation of the centro-surface by means of the centro-curves, for the reason that it can be carried on more precisely now that we know the forms of the principal sections and of the nodal curve. The two figures exhibit (as regards one extent of the surface) the portions already distinguished as (A), and (B): they intersect each other in the nodal curve, shown in each of the figures.



26. Consider first the generation of the portion (A) by means of the major-mean sequential centro-curves. The major-mean curves of curvature (extending to those below the plane of xy) commence with a portion (extending from umbilicus to umbilicus) of the ellipse $\frac{X^2}{a^2} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2} = 1$, this may be termed the vertical curve, and they end with the whole ellipse $\frac{X^2}{a^2} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2} = 1$, this may be termed the horizontal curve. The normals at the several points of the vertical curve successively intersect each other so as to form a circle, namely a part of the cuspidal curve, viz. from cusp (b)(b) all the way to other umbilicar centres at once, viz. to a first-cusped curve in fig. (A), which may be defined as the principal outcrop of $-\beta\gamma$, the corresponding entrolicus being the umbilicar centre $-\gamma a$. The successive forms of the major-mean outcrop as we pass to the plane infinity are outcrops as shown in the figure (B). We have in each case attended only to the curve of curvature lying above the plane of xy and the corresponding major-mean sequential centro-curve is now in $\eta = a$; for to value of β between $-c, -b$ inclusive; the resulting curve of curvature is for $\eta = -b$, the umbilicar shown above in fig. (A), when these are only $\beta = b, \eta = a$, the umbilicar centre at first.

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opening out the two component parts thereof: the two upper cusps of the curve (b) are atomic on the geodesic of the curve-surface, and the two lower cusps upon two detached portions respectively of the cuspline of the centro-surface. And as the curve



of curvature gradually broadens out and ultimately coincides with the XY -section of the ellipsoid, the four cusped curve continues to open itself out, and ultimately coincides as shown figure (c) with the xy -evolute of the centro-surface, viz. this evolute is the sequential centro-curve belonging to the horizontal curve of curvature. The curves of curvature so that we have, for the special case which is now under consideration, the normal at any point of any of the major-mean sequential centro-curve as the line tangent thereto. Each, as we have above said, of these normals meets in some outcrop in the figure (c).

27. We consider next the generation of the portion (B) by means of the major-mean concomitant centro-curves. Starting as before with the vertical curve of curvature, the concomitant centro-curve is a finite portion (terminated each way at an umbilicar centre) of the curve of the curve XY -evolute, viz. we have then the outcrops ξ, ξ , which terminate the curve. The successive forms of the concomitant centro-curve are as shown in figure (B). We have in each case attended only to the curve of curvature below the plane of xy and the corresponding sequential centro-curve is also more on the negative side. Pass we further to the cuspidal X, Y, Z and lastly $(X, Y, Z) =$ the cuspidal X, Y, Z as X, Y, Z, X, Y, Z , will completely deduced, the geometrical signification is anything but clear.

28. There is a precisely similar generation of the portion (B) by means of the minor-mean sequential centro-curves, and of the portion (B) by means of the minor-mean concomitant centro-curves.

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The Nodal Curve. Art. Nos. 29 to 60.

29. As before different points on the ellipsoid correspond to the same point on the centro-surface, this will be a point on the Nodal Curve: the conditions for this if (ξ, η) , (ξ_0, η_0) are the parameters for the two points on the ellipsoid, are obviously

$$\begin{aligned} a^2(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta) &= a^2(a + \xi_0)^3(a + \eta_0), \\ b^2(b + \xi)^3(b + \eta) &= b^2(b + \xi_0)^3(b + \eta_0), \\ c^2(c + \xi)^3(c + \eta) &= c^2(c + \xi_0)^3(c + \eta_0); \end{aligned}$$

these equations in effect determine η as a function of ξ , so that the three equations will be in effect a known function of ξ .

The relation between ξ and η in fact be found by eliminating ξ_0, η_0 from the foregoing equations, but it is easier to eliminate η and η_0 ; thus consider obtaining ξ , and ξ_0 between as values of η , viz. may be regarded as a known function of ξ ; in the equation in two equations may be expressed in terms of ξ, ξ_0 , so that each of these quantities will be in effect a known function of ξ .

30. The relation between ξ, ξ_0 in the first instance given in the form

$$0 = \begin{vmatrix} a^3(a + \xi)^3 + b^3 + c^3, & (a + \xi_0)^3, & (a + \xi)^3 \\ b^3(b + \xi)^3 + a^2 + c^2, & (b + \xi_0)^3, & (b + \xi)^3 \\ c^3(c + \xi)^3 + a + b, & (c + \xi_0)^3, & (c + \xi)^3 \end{vmatrix} = 0.$$

Throwing out a factor $(\xi - \xi_0)$, this becomes

$$\begin{aligned} &\Sigma\{a^2(ac + b^2)^2 + a^2 + b^2 + c^2\} \\ &+ (b - c)\{abc^2 + (bac)^2 + c^2(b + c)(b + c)(a + \xi)\} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

where the left-hand side is a symmetrical function of ξ and ξ_0 , and therefore divisible by $(\xi - \xi_0)^2$. It is obviously to $(b - c)$, viz. we have thus for the determination of η, η_0 , the simple equations, obtained by throwing out the factor $\xi - \xi_0$.

To work this out, write $\xi + \xi_0 = p$, $\xi\xi_0 = q$, the result the rentals quotient being $\frac{1}{\Delta(p^2 - 4q)}$,

$$\Sigma[(b - c)(a + p) + bc] = \begin{vmatrix} 3p^2c, & 3(a^2)(b^2 + c)(c^2) \\ b + cp & b \\ +p^2(b + c) & c^2 \\ +b^3(b + c) & b \\ +3p^4q & c \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

where the left-hand side divides by $\frac{1}{\Delta}(p^2 - 4q)$.

¹ This was my first method of solution; and I have thought the results quite interesting simply to ensure them; but it will appear in time that I have succeeded in expressing ξ, ξ_0, η, η_0 in terms of a single parameter ξ .

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31. Developing and reducing, and omitting this factor, the final result is

$$6R + 3Q(p + P)(p + Pp) + 3pq = 0,$$

when as before P, Q, R denote $a + b + c, bc + ca + ab, abc$ respectively; that is,

$$6R + 3Q(P + Pp) + P(P^2 + 4Q)q + 2pq + (P + Q)q = 0,$$

or, as this may also be written,

$$\begin{aligned} &6R + 3Q(p + P_0) + (P + Q)q \\ &\quad + \xi_0(P + 4Q) \\ &\quad + \xi_0^2(P + Q) - 2\xi_0q = 0, \end{aligned}$$

viz. the parameters ξ, ξ_0 have a symmetrical $(2, 2)$ correspondence.

32. From the equations $(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta) = (a + \xi_0)^3(a + \eta_0)$, etc., we have

$$\Sigma(b - c)\{(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta) - (a + \xi_0)^3(a + \eta_0)\} = 0,$$

and observing that the term in $(\eta - \eta_0)$ is

$$\begin{aligned} &\sqrt{[\beta(\beta - \gamma)(a + \xi)^2 + a(b - \gamma)(a + \xi)^2 + a(b - \gamma)(b + \xi)^2 + c(a - \beta)(c + \xi)^2]} \\ &\quad + a(\gamma - \beta)\{2a + \xi\} - 2a\{a^2 + \xi\} \\ &\quad + b(a - \gamma)\{2b + \xi\} \\ &\quad + c(\beta - a)\{2c + \xi\}, \end{aligned}$$

these are readily reduced to

$$\begin{aligned} &[3\xi - \xi_0 + (P + Q)p + (P + Q)(\xi + \xi_0)] \cdot \eta = -[(P + Q)\xi + 3\xi_0 + (b + a)\xi_0], \\ &[(\xi - \xi_0) + a^2P_0] \cdot (\eta - \eta_0) - \dots, \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} &[3(\xi - \xi_0) + 2P(\xi + \xi_0) + (P + Q)q + (P + Q)(\xi + \xi_0) + Q(\xi - \xi_0)] \cdot \eta = -\dots, \\ &3(\xi - \xi_0) + 2P(\xi + \xi_0) + Q(\xi - \xi_0) = -[(P + Q)\xi + 3\xi_0 + (b + a)\xi_0], \end{aligned}$$

and if we hence determine the values $3(\xi^2 - \xi_0^2) = \eta_0$, we find that the resulting terms divide by $\xi - \xi_0$, and we have

$$\begin{aligned} &3\xi_0^2(\xi_0 - \xi) - \xi^2[(b + a)\xi + 3\xi_0] = (\xi + \xi_0)\xi_0(b + a)(\xi + \xi_0)(\xi + a) \\ &\quad + \xi_0 \dots, \\ &\quad + \xi_0 \dots. \end{aligned}$$

Hence observing that by the relation between ξ, ξ_0 , the first term is

$$= -3Q\xi_0 + (P + Q)q + 2\xi_0q,$$

the equations become

$$\begin{aligned} 1 : \eta : \eta_0 &= -[Q + p(P + Q) - 3\xi_0] \cdot Q \\ &\quad : R(2\xi_0 + 2) - \xi^2(P + Q\xi) \\ &\quad : R(3\xi_0^2 - \xi^2) - \xi^2P(P + Q\xi). \end{aligned}$$

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and we thus have

$$\eta = \frac{R(\xi_0^2 - \xi^2) - \xi^2 P(P + Q\xi)}{P\{Q + q(P + Q) - 3\xi_0\}},$$

which, considering ξ_0 as a given function of ξ , gives η as a function of ξ .

33. I write $\xi - \xi_0 = 2u$, $\xi + \xi_0 = 2t$, so that $p = 2t$, $q = t^2 - u^2$, $\xi = t + u$, $\xi_0 = t - u$. The relation between ξ, ξ_0 thus becomes

$$6R + 6Qt + (P + Q)(t^2 - u^2) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$u^2 = t^2 + \frac{6R+6Qt}{P+Q};$$

so that taking t as a parameter, and considering u as a node real value of u , respectively, we have the relation

$$\xi = \frac{(t+u)\sqrt{P+Q+R(P+Q\xi+Q\xi_0)}}{P+Q+2t},$$

and the value of η is taken as $-3\xi, \xi_0, -2 = -2\xi$. The relation between ξ, ξ_0 in the simple form $\xi + \xi_0 = 2t$, hence appears as an arithmetic mode of expression: which is in some respects advantageous, but I propose that this can be modified.

34. On comparison of reality is easily found

$$y^2 = \frac{(a + a^2)(a + b)\{a + bc(a + 1)\} + ac(a + 1)\{a + b - c\}}{a + b + c\{a + (b + c)\}},$$

where $a = -\frac{1}{2}(P + a)$, $b = \frac{1}{2}(P + Q)$; viz. as we then have a in entruncate coordinates of a point in a plane, (a, t) will be the rectangular coordinates of the same point referred to as a , and also the equation of conic referred to set $(2x - 2, x)$ at (a, t) , viz. we have for the entire centro-surface in this way.

35. The curve is a conic curve symmetrical in regard to the axis of x , and having the three asymptotes,

$$x = -t, \quad y = \frac{1}{2}(P + a) \pm \frac{1}{2}(P + a)\sqrt{c(P + 1)(P - a)};$$

moreover we have $y = 0$ for the values $x = a, x, C$ where the curve cuts the axes of C, E, F , as shown in the figure: a, C, E , are at the distances from the centre, and with these data it is easy to draw the curve. It is then the form τ , that whence writing $t = \tau, u = 1$ to $\eta + a$, and let $t \cdots \tau + a$, corresponding to the umbilicar centre; and at Ω, Ω , we have $\xi = -\beta, \eta = a$, and $\xi - \beta$, etc. corresponding to the corner.

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We have

$$\begin{aligned} A^2 + B^2 c &= \frac{1}{2} \Delta + a^2 (P + 1); \\ B &= -\frac{1}{2} (\gamma + a)^2 (\eta + a) + 2\Delta (P + 2 + \gamma), \\ B &= -\frac{1}{2} (\gamma + a)^2 (b + a^2 \omega), \end{aligned}$$

hence the rational part in question is

$$= \pm \frac{(\eta + a)^2}{(2a + Pp + a)} \sqrt{\frac{a + R + (1 - \xi)(2 + \xi)}{P\{Q + q(P + Q) - 3\xi_0\}}} (2 + \xi)$$

32. Write $\xi - \xi_0 = a + \frac{a}{u}$, etc., $\xi - \xi_0 = -\frac{a}{2}$, $\xi_0 + 2 = \frac{2}{u}$, $c, y = 0; p = -a, c$. The relation between ξ, ξ_0 thus becomes

$$\xi - \xi_0 = a + \frac{a}{2u}, \quad \xi - \xi_0 = -\frac{a}{2}, \xi_0 + 2 = \frac{2}{u}, c, y = 0; p = -a, c.$$

or as that the curve $\Omega = 0$ is obtained by eliminating ξ from this equation and the foregoing, regard to ξ at the cubic function becomes

$$(a^2 + \xi)(b - \xi)\left(c + \xi + \frac{\xi}{a + \beta}\right) = 0;$$

that is, the equation has the values

$$\xi = -a^2, \quad \xi = -\beta^2, \quad \xi = -\xi_0 = -a(a + \beta).$$

But these last values give

$$a + \xi = \frac{aa}{a + \beta}, \quad \beta + \xi = -\frac{aa}{a + \beta}.$$

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and for $\xi = ($ we have

$$u(2(a + \xi) - 1) \left(\frac{2u\beta\gamma}{a+\beta} \right) \eta_0 = \frac{(a^2)}{(a-\beta)^3} \eta, \quad \frac{(a-\beta)^3}{aP\beta} \eta_0,$$

so that solving for greater simplicity, $(a - \beta)\eta_0 = -a\beta\eta$, the formulae become

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{2P\xi}{a^2} &= \frac{3a^2}{a^2} = \frac{3a^2}{\beta-a}, \\ \frac{2P\xi}{\beta^2} &= \frac{3\beta^2}{\beta-a}, \\ \frac{2P\xi}{\gamma^2} &= \frac{-a\beta\gamma}{a^2+a\beta} = -\frac{a+\beta}{a}, \\ \frac{a+\beta}{\Omega \cdot 1} \Omega &= \dots, \end{aligned}$$

32. This shows that there is the curtsey a cusp, the cuspidal tangent being in the plane of xy . It appears moreover that this tangent constants with the tangent of the evolute. In fact, from the equation $(ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2 - a^2y^2 = 0$ of the evolute we have

$$\frac{(ax)^2}{a} + \frac{(by)^2}{b} + \frac{(ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2}{a^2} = 0,$$

or substituting for (a, y) their values as in the outcrop,

$$\frac{2(a-a)\{b-a\}\beta-a}{x^2(a-\beta)^2} = \frac{a+ax}{\beta+a^2-a^2} \cdot \frac{dy}{dx} = 0,$$

that is,

$$\frac{d}{dx} = \frac{ax^2+ax^2(\beta-a)}{a^2(a+\beta)-a^2 \cdot \frac{dy}{dx}}.$$

which is satisfied by the foregoing values of $\frac{x}{a}$ and $\frac{y}{a}$ at the two tangents there coincide.

We have

$$4(da^2 + (ba^2)(b - 2a^2 - \dots \sqrt{4\Sigma ay^2 + ax^2}) = \frac{a+a+a}{a(a+\beta)^2 a} \eta \dots \xi,$$

which is virtue of

$$(ay)(2+y)(a+\beta) = \beta y^2(2y+a) + \beta y^2(2y+a) + (2y(2+a)+a) - 4y^3(2+a) - 3y^4 y^2(a+\beta),$$

is

$$4[(by)^2 + (by)^2 + (ay^2 + 3y^4 y^2(a+\beta))] = \frac{2(a+\beta)^2}{a(a+\beta)^2} \eta \dots \xi.$$

(observe $2(a^2 + \beta) - a(a - \beta) = -(a + (a + \beta)) = -8a^2$, is negative)

$$= -\frac{2a^2}{a(a+\beta)^2} \eta \dots \xi.$$

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if $\frac{dy}{dx}$ be the value at the outcrop. Writing $\frac{a^2}{a^2}$ for the element of the are we have

$$\frac{ds^2}{a^2} \frac{dx^2(a-\beta)^3}{(a-\beta)^2} - \frac{4}{a}\eta - \frac{8a^2}{a},$$

$$\frac{ds^2}{a^2} \frac{dx^2(-a\beta\gamma)^2}{(a-\beta)^2} - \frac{8a^2}{a},$$

which exhibit the form at the outcrop.

The Nodal Curve, expressions for the coordinates in terms of a single parameter a . Art. Nos. 33 to 41.

33. After the foregoing investigation of the nodal curve, I was led to perceive that it is possible to express ξ, η, ξ_0, η_0 in terms of a single variable η ; and thus to obtain expressions for the coordinates of a point of the nodal curve in terms of the single variable a . The analytical form of the nodal curve being real, with its imaginary values of ξ, η , the modes y may we may assume

$$\xi = -b^2 - p(b^2 - a^2 - b^2),$$

$$\eta = -b^2 + p(b^2 - a^2 - b^2),$$

($i = \sqrt{-1}$ as usual): viz. p denote one or other of the quantities

$$y_+ = a + (a^2 - b^2), \quad q = a - (a^2 - b^2);$$

the expressions for $-\beta\gamma x^2, -\gamma ay^2$ become

$$= [(b-p)(a+1)(b-q)^3](b-p)^3,$$

and we have therefore the condition that this shall be real (for the two values $b = p, b = -b$); being real, it will in certain cases be positive, in other cases negative, and the values for the remaining condition is given by the equation

$$\Delta'(b^2 - \xi^2 - \xi_0^2 - 4)(b^2 + b^2 + \xi^2 + 2b^2)^2 + p^2(b - \xi^2 - 2)(b^2 + \xi)^2 - 0 = 0.$$

34. The condition of reality is easily found to be

$$(\beta - p)(p + \beta - 1) + (a + p)^2 + (\gamma + p)^2 + 4(a + p)(\beta - p) + (a + p)^2(b - \beta) - p^2q^2 = 0;$$

viz. this equation in Δ must have the form $-a, b$, suppose to a value

$$P = p, \quad q = qP_0p + p^2,$$

we have therefore

$$\frac{(\gamma-a)\beta}{a^2} = a + \frac{a(a^2-b^2)}{2bg(\gamma-a)}\sqrt{Y} \cdot \eta(a-\beta-\gamma)(a+\beta+\gamma),$$

where, regarding X, Y are given functions of a , the coordinates of a plane in a cubic curve having the point $X = 0, Y = 0$ for a node, writing $Y = b + 3a(X + 1)$, X will be such of these is rational function of a . The curve has the property that being any line through the outcrop, the tangents at the points of the curve, the corresponding outcrops on it are

$$(a^2 + Y)(a^2 + a)(a + 1) + (b + 1)(a^2 + b)\beta(a^2 + a) = -a^2(b - p)^3 + a(p + p)^3,$$

for a point on the nodal curve.

35. To complete the investigation, writing for a moment $T = 3 = 3a^2(X + 1)$, we obtain

$$\frac{(b-p)^2}{a^2} = \frac{a}{2a^2(a+a-1)} + \frac{a(a^2)(b-\xi)^3}{a+b-1},$$

or putting for a moment

$$\frac{(\gamma-a)\beta}{a^2} = K,$$

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we have

$$\begin{aligned} X &= \frac{a(K-7)(a-1)}{a+1-K}, \\ X_0 &= \frac{K(a-7)(a+1)}{a+1-K}, \\ Y &= K \frac{3K(a^2-1)+2(a+1)}{a+1-K}, \\ Y_0 &= K \frac{3(a-1)(K-2)(a+1)}{a+1-K}, \\ Z &= 2K \frac{(b-1)X(a-2+1)}{a+1-K}, \\ Z_0 &= 2K \frac{(b-1)(X-2+1)}{a+1-K}, \end{aligned}$$

or substituting for K its value we have

$$\begin{aligned} K(a-1) &= \frac{(a-1)^2}{ab} \left(a^2 - \frac{8aq}{(a-1)^2} \right), \\ &= -\frac{(a-1)^2}{ab} \left(a + \frac{2q}{a-1} \right) \left(a - \frac{2q}{a-1} \right); \end{aligned}$$

$aa+1-K = -\frac{1}{ab}(a^2+1)(a+b-1)(a-p), \dots +b(a-p)$, and changing the sign of the radical we have the values of $\frac{x}{a}, \dots$,

36. Write for a moment,

$$\begin{aligned} \left[\Delta - \frac{1}{2}(\gamma - a) \sqrt{1 + \sqrt{\frac{2a(a-2-4\beta+2)}{a(a-2)}}} \right] - (a - 8a\beta + \sqrt{\beta})Y + B\sqrt{\delta} &= 0, \\ \left[\Delta - \frac{1}{2}(\gamma - a) \sqrt{1 + \sqrt{\frac{2a(a-2-4\beta+2)}{a(a-2)}}} \right] - (a - 8a\beta + \sqrt{\beta})Y + B\sqrt{\delta} &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

then in the product of these two expressions the rational part is $= A^2A + B^2B$; and from the manner in which they were arrived at we have $9 = A_1A + B_1B$, and the rational part is thus

$$= -\frac{16}{a^2}(B^2 - B'B).$$

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42. We have then

$$\eta = \frac{-R(a^2 + 2A) - (a^2 + A)^3(a^2 - b^2 - c^2 + A)}{-a^2\beta\gamma + A(a^4 - b^2c^2)},$$

and I assume

$$\eta = -a^2 + \frac{H\beta\gamma}{(\beta - \gamma)^3},$$

and investigate the value of H . We have

$$-R(a^2 + 2A) - (a^2 + A)^3(a^2 - b^2 - c^2 + A) = a^4\beta\gamma + A\Theta,$$

suppose. The equation therefore is

$$\frac{a^4\beta\gamma + A\Theta}{-a^2\beta\gamma + A(a^4 - b^2c^2)} = -a^2 + \frac{H\beta\gamma}{(\beta - \gamma)^3},$$

that is,

$$A\Theta = -a^2A(a^4 - b^2c^2) + \frac{H\beta\gamma}{(\beta - \gamma)^3}\{-a^2\beta\gamma + A(a^4 - b^2c^2)\} = 0.$$

Omitting the factor A and multiplying by $(\beta - \gamma)^3$, this is

$$(\beta - \gamma)^3\{\Theta + a^2(a^4 - b^2c^2)\}H\{-a^2\beta\gamma + A(a^4 - b^2c^2)\} = 0,$$

in which equation

$$\Theta = -2R - a^6 - (3a^4 + 3a^2A + A^2)(a^2 - b^2 - c^2 + A),$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} \Theta + a^2(a^4 - b^2c^2) &= -3a^6 + 3a^4(b^2 + c^2) - 3a^2b^2c^2 \\ &\quad + A\{-6a^4 + 3a^2(b^2 + c^2)\}A^2(-4a^2 + b^2 + c^2) - A^3 \\ &= 3a^2\beta\gamma + 3a^2A(\beta - \gamma)A^2(\beta - \gamma - 2a^2) - A^3. \end{aligned}$$

43. Hence, substituting for A its value and multiplying by $(\beta - \gamma)^3$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} (\beta - \gamma)^3\{\Theta + a^2(a^4 - b^2c^2)\} &= 3a^2\beta\gamma(\beta - \gamma)^3 - 9a^2\beta\gamma(\beta - \gamma)^3 \\ &\quad + 9\beta^2\gamma^2(\beta - \gamma - 2a^2)(\beta - \gamma) + 27\beta^3\gamma^3, \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$\{-6a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 9\beta\gamma\}\{(\beta - \gamma)^2 + 3\beta\gamma\}\beta\gamma = \{-6a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 9\beta\gamma\}(\beta^2 + \beta\gamma + \gamma^2)\beta\gamma.$$

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and the equation thus is

$$\{-2a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 3\beta\gamma\}(\beta^2 + \beta\gamma + \gamma^2)\beta\gamma + H \left\{ -a^2\beta\gamma - \frac{3\beta\gamma}{(\beta - \gamma)^2}(a^4 - b^2c^2) \right\}(\beta - \gamma) = 0,$$

or finally

$$H\{a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 3(a^4 - b^2c^2)\} = \{-2a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 3\beta\gamma\}(\beta^2 + \beta\gamma + \gamma^2).$$

But $c^2 = a^2 + \beta$, $b^2 = a^2 - \gamma$, and hence

$$a^4 - b^2c^2 = -a^2(\beta - \gamma) + \beta\gamma,$$

and therefore

$$a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 3(a^4 - b^2c^2) = -2a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 3\beta\gamma.$$

The equation thus divides by $-2a^2(\beta - \gamma) + 3\beta\gamma$, and we have

$$H = \beta^2 + \beta\gamma + \gamma^2,$$

or, as this may also be written,

$$H = \alpha^2 - \beta\gamma = \beta^2 - \gamma\alpha = \gamma^2 - \alpha\beta.$$

So that H has the value originally so denoted, and we have then the asserted value of η .

44. III. Lastly the equation

$$0 = (a^2 + \xi)^3(a^2 + \eta) = (a^2 + \xi_1)^3(a^2 + \eta_1)$$

is satisfied if $a^2 + \eta = 0$, $a^2 + \eta_1 = 0$; the equations

$$(b^2 + \xi)^3(b^2 + \eta) = (b^2 + \xi_1)^3(b^2 + \eta_1), \quad (c^2 + \xi)^3(c^2 + \eta) = (c^2 + \xi_1)^3(c^2 + \eta_1)$$

then give

$$(b^2 + \xi)^3 = (b^2 + \xi_1)^3, \quad (c^2 + \xi)^3 = (c^2 + \xi_1)^3.$$

These can be satisfied by $\xi = \xi_1$, leading to $\xi = \xi_1 = -a^2$, which is case I, or else by

$$b^2 + \xi = \omega(b^2 + \xi_1), \quad c^2 + \xi = \omega^2(c^2 + \xi_1),$$

that is,

$$\xi = \omega b^2 + \omega^2 c^2, \quad \xi_1 = \omega^2 b^2 + \omega c^2.$$

To show that these values satisfy the relation between ξ, ξ_1 , observe that they give

$$\xi + \xi_1 = -b^2 - c^2, \quad \xi\xi_1 = b^4 - b^2c^2 + c^4,$$

and the relation becomes

$$6a^2b^2c^2 - 3\{a^2(b^2 + c^2) + b^2c^2\}(b^2 + c^2)\{a^2 + (b^2 + c^2)\}3(b^4 + c^4) - 3(b^2 + c^2)(b^4 - b^2c^2 + c^4) = 0,$$

which is an identity.

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45. I will show that these values of ξ, ξ_1 give the foregoing values $\eta = \eta_1 = -a^2$. We have, from the determining formulae,

$$1 : \eta - \eta_1 : \eta + \eta_1 = a^2(b^2 + c^2) : 0 \cdot (\xi - \xi_1) : -2a^2(b^2 + c^2),$$

or

$$\eta - \eta_1 = 0, \quad \eta + \eta_1 = -2a^2;$$

that is, $\eta = \eta_1 = -a^2$.

46. For the real umbilicar centres and outcrops we have

I. $\xi = -b^2, \quad \eta = -b^2, \quad \xi_1 = -b^2, \quad \eta_1 = -b^2$:

$$\begin{aligned} Y &= 0, & Y_1 &= 0, \\ y &= 0. \end{aligned}$$

II. The real outcrop case is

$$\xi = -b^2, \quad \eta = -a^2 - \frac{3\alpha\beta}{\gamma - \alpha},$$

with the corresponding conjugate values

$$\xi_1 = -b^2, \quad \eta_1 = -b^2 - \frac{3\alpha\beta}{\gamma - \alpha}.$$

For this case the source gives the concomitant and sequential ellipses in the form

$$\begin{aligned} Z &= 0, & Z_1 &= 0, \\ Y^2 &= -b^2 - \frac{3\alpha\beta}{\gamma - \alpha}, & Y_1^2 &= -b^2 - \frac{3\alpha\beta}{\gamma - \alpha}, \end{aligned}$$

and

$$\begin{aligned} z &= 0, \\ \frac{\gamma - \alpha}{\gamma(\gamma - \alpha)} &\text{ at the real outcrop.} \end{aligned}$$

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Nodal curve in vicinity of umbilicus centre, $ax^2 = -y^2$, $c^2z^2 = w^2$, Art. No. 47 to 49.

47. Write

$$\xi = -b^2 + p, \quad \eta = -b^2 + r, \quad \xi_0 = -b^2 + q, \quad \eta_0 = -b^2 + s;$$

we have to find the relation between p, q, r, s ; first for p, q , the equation of correspondence gives

$$\begin{aligned} 6R + 5Q(p + q + 2b^2 - 8b^2) + (P + Q)(p + q + b^2) \\ + 5\{-2b^2 + 2bQp + p^2 - b^2(p + q) - 2bp - p\} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$3(p + q)(3b^2 - 2b^2) + (b^2 - b^2)(p + q + 2bp) = 0,$$

or writing these equations as follows

$$3(p + q)(\gamma - \beta) + (3\beta + 3\gamma - 2)\beta\eta = 0,$$

viz. this is

$$3p + 3q + \frac{8\beta\eta}{\gamma - \beta}(p + q) = 0;$$

or in symbolic form

$$3p + q + \frac{2\beta\eta}{\gamma - \beta}(\xi_0)^2 = 0.$$

48. Now the equations

$$(a^2 + \xi)(a + \xi)^2 = (a^2 + \xi_0)(a + \xi_0)^2 = a^2(b + \xi)^2(b + \xi_0)^2 = (a + \xi)^2(\dots),$$

putting therein for ξ, η, ξ_0, η_0 their values, give the first of them

$$\log\left(1 + \frac{r}{a^2}\right) - \log\left(1 + \frac{s}{a^2}\right) = 8\log\left(1 + \frac{p}{a^2}\right) - 8\log\left(1 + \frac{q}{a^2}\right),$$

that is,

$$r + 3p + \frac{1}{2a^2}(r^2 + 3p^2) + \frac{1}{3a^4}(r^3 + 3p^3) + \dots = s + 3q + \frac{1}{2a^2}(s^2 + 3q^2) + \frac{1}{3a^4}(s^3 + 3q^3) + \dots;$$

and similarly the second equation

$$r + 3p + \frac{1}{2a^2}(r^2 + 3p^2) + \frac{1}{3a^4}(r^3 + 3p^3) + \dots = s + 3q + \frac{1}{2a^2}(s^2 + 3q^2) + \frac{1}{3a^4}(s^3 + 3q^3) + \dots;$$

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whence multiplying by γ , and adding,

$$(\gamma + s)\left[r + 3p + \frac{1}{2}(r^2 + 3p^2)\right] = (\gamma + s)\left[r + 3p + 3p_0 + \frac{1}{3a^4}(r^3 + 3p^3)\right],$$

which, neglecting terms of the third order, is

$$r + 3p = s + 3q,$$

Subtracting the two equations we have

$$\frac{1}{3}\left(\frac{1}{a^2} + \frac{1}{b^2}\right)(r^2 + 3p^2) + \frac{1}{a^2}\left(\frac{1}{a^2} - \frac{1}{b^2}\right)(r^3 + 3p^3) = \frac{1}{3}\left(\frac{1}{a^2} + \frac{1}{b^2}\right)(s^2 + 3q^2) + \frac{1}{a^2}\left(\frac{1}{a^2} - \frac{1}{b^2}\right)(s^3 + 3q^3);$$

viz. this is the same thing,

$$r^2 + 3p^2 + \frac{2}{3}\left(\frac{\gamma - a^2}{\gamma}\right)(r^3 + 3p^3) = s^2 + 3q^2 + \frac{2}{3}(s^2 + 3q^2)(r - s) - 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$r^2 - s^2 + 3(p^2 - q^2) + \frac{1}{3}\left(\frac{\gamma - a^2}{\gamma}\right)(r^2 + s^2)(r - s) - 0,$$

which, putting therein $r - s = -3(p - q)$, is

$$-r - s + 3(p + q) + 3a\left(\frac{\gamma - a^2}{\gamma}\right)(r^2 + s^2) + 9(p^2 + q^2) = 0,$$

say this is

$$-r - s + 3(p + q) + 2\Delta = 0,$$

combining herewith

$$r - s + 3(p - q) = 0,$$

we have

$$r + 3p - \Delta = 0,$$

and

$$s + 3q - \Delta = 0,$$

where

$$\Delta = \frac{1}{2}\frac{\gamma + a^2}{\gamma}(-r^2 - s^2 + p^2 + q^2 + qq + q^2),$$

But substituting herein the values $r + 3p = -3p$, $s = -3q$, this becomes

$$\Delta = \frac{1}{2}\left(\frac{\gamma + a^2}{\gamma}\right)[-4p^2 - 4q^2 - 3p^2] = -\frac{1}{2}\left(\frac{\gamma + a^2}{\gamma}\right)q^2,$$

and then

$$r = -p + 3p_0 + \Delta = -3p - \frac{1}{2}\left(\frac{\gamma + a^2}{\gamma}\right)q^2,$$

that is,

$$r = 3p + 2(p + q) + \Delta = -\frac{4(\gamma - a)}{\gamma a^2}q.$$

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49. We have then

$$a^2 x^2 = \frac{y^2}{a^2} \left(1 + \frac{r}{a^2}\right) \left(1 + \frac{p}{a^2}\right) = \frac{y^2}{a^2} \left(1 + \frac{r+3p}{a^2} + \frac{3p(r+p)}{a^4}\right) = \frac{y^2}{a^2} \left(1 + \frac{-4(\gamma-a)q}{ay\gamma} + \frac{6q}{ya^2}\right) = \frac{y^2}{a^2} \left[1 + \frac{2(p-3q)}{a\gamma y}\right],$$

and in the same way from $a^2 x^2 = \frac{a^2}{b^2} \left(1 - \frac{r}{a^2}\right) \left(1 - \frac{p}{a^2}\right)$, we have

$$a^2 x_0^2 = \frac{y^2}{a^2} \left[1 + \frac{2(p+\beta)}{a\gamma}\right];$$

moreover we have at once

$$b^2 y^2 = \frac{a^2}{a^2} - \frac{1}{a\gamma} q^2.$$

Hence, writing $x + \delta x, 0 + \delta y, z + \delta z$ for x, y, z , we find

$$\delta x = \frac{1}{2} p \frac{2(p-3q)}{ay\gamma} \cdot q^2,$$

$$\delta y = \frac{1}{2} p \sqrt{\frac{a}{\gamma}} \cdot q,$$

$$\delta z = \frac{1}{2} p \frac{2(p-\beta)}{ay\gamma} \cdot q^2,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\delta x : \delta y : \delta z = \frac{2(p-3q)}{ay\gamma} : \sqrt{\frac{a}{\gamma}} : \frac{2(p-\beta)}{ay\gamma},$$

where a, z denote the value at the umbilicar centre.

Nodal curve in vicinity of real entropy, viz. $ax^2 = \alpha^2, by^2 = \beta^2$. Art. Nos. 50 to 52.

50. Write

$$\begin{aligned} \xi &= -a^2 + p, & \eta &= -a^2 + r, \\ \xi_0 &= -a^2 + q, & \eta_0 &= -a^2 + s. \end{aligned}$$

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and first for the relation between η and η_0 , writing for a moment $\frac{3p\eta}{a-\beta} = \eta_0 = -Q$, and therefore $\xi_0 = -a + Q$, the equation of correspondence gives

$$-3a\beta\gamma + (\eta_0 + s)\beta + (\beta + \eta + \frac{1}{2}\eta^2) - 3\eta\eta(\eta + Q) - 3a^2(s + Q) = 0,$$

which, putting for Q its value, is

$$\begin{aligned} & -9\eta(\eta - s + 3rs - \frac{6a^2}{a-\beta}) \\ & + (s + 3\eta r) \left[a^2(s + r) - \beta(r + r) + (a + \beta)\eta s - \frac{3a\beta}{a^2-\beta}(\eta + r) \right] \\ & - 3a\beta(s + r) - 3a^2(s + r) - \frac{4a^2\beta}{a-\beta} = 0; \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} & (3\eta s + 2\eta^2(r - \beta)) - 4a^2\eta s \\ & + (s^2 + 7a\eta + 5\eta s) + \frac{a^2 - 4a\beta + \beta^2}{a-\beta} + 4(\eta + s)\eta a + s - \beta \\ & + 3a(\eta + s) = 0, \end{aligned}$$

or, in small values,

$$\left(2a + \frac{a+\beta a^2}{a-\beta} \right) (s + 3r) = 2a\beta r.$$

viz. writing $\frac{a}{(a-\beta)^2}$ for $\frac{a}{(a-\beta)^2}$, this becomes

$$\frac{2a^2}{a-\beta} (s + 3r) = 2a\beta(\eta - s).$$

51. Moreover, from the equation $(c + \xi)^3(c + \eta) = (c + \xi_0)^2(c + \eta_0)$, we have c since a and a are the same order: β , a of the order ϵ ; arising from the variation of a , an indefinitely small in regard to those arising from the variation of ξ ; and we have

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{3\eta s}{a-\beta} &= -\frac{3a\beta}{a^2}(s - r) = -3p\eta - \frac{(p-q)}{2(a-\gamma)}, \\ \frac{3\eta s}{a-\beta} &= -3a - \frac{3a\beta}{a^2}\eta(p - q) = -3p\eta - \frac{(p-q)}{2(a-\gamma)}, \end{aligned}$$

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and for δx etc. we have

$$a^2 x^2 = -\frac{1}{a^2} \left(\frac{a\beta\gamma}{a^2} \right)^2 p\eta = -\frac{(a^2-\beta)^2}{(a-\beta)^2} \left[\frac{-(a-\beta)^2}{4(\gamma+2)\eta\eta} \right],$$

so that solving for greater simplicity, $(\beta - a)\eta_0 = -y\beta$, the formulae become

$$\frac{2a^2}{a-\beta}(s+3r) = -\frac{(b-a)^2}{a-\beta} \delta\eta - \frac{(a-\beta)}{(a-\beta)^2} \delta\eta q^2.$$

52. This shows that there is at the entropy a cusp, the cuspidal tangent being in the plane of xy . It appears moreover that this tangent coincides with the tangent of the evolute. In fact, from the equation $(ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2 - c^2 y^2 = 0$ of the evolute we have

$$\frac{(ax)^3}{a} + \frac{(by)^3}{b} - \frac{(ax^2)^2 + (by^2)^2}{a^2} \frac{dy}{dx} = 0,$$

or substituting for (x, y) their values as in the entropy,

$$\frac{2(b-a)(b-\beta)(\beta-a)}{a^2(a-\beta)^2} - \frac{(a-\beta) + a\eta\eta}{x^2(b-\beta) + a\beta\beta - a\beta} \cdot \frac{dy}{dx} = 0,$$

that is,

$$\frac{dy}{dx} = \frac{2(a^2y + a\eta x)(\beta-a)}{a(a+\beta) - a\eta} \frac{dy}{dx}.$$

which is satisfied by the foregoing values of $\frac{\delta x}{\delta y}$, $\frac{\delta y}{\delta x}$; the two tangents therefore coincide.

We have

$$4(by)^2 + 4(by)^2(4by^2 - 4)\sqrt{ay^2 + by^2} \delta y = \frac{4(a+\beta)^2}{a(a+\beta)^2} \eta ay - \dots \xi,$$

which is virtue of

$$(ay)(\sqrt{a+\beta})(\beta y^2(\sqrt{a}+a)) + \beta(y^2(\sqrt{a}+a)) + (a(2+a))y^2 = 4(y\sqrt{a^2-4} + 3y^4y^2(a+\beta)),$$

is

$$4[(by)^2(by)^2 + (by^2 + 3y^4y^2(a+\beta))] = \frac{2(a+\beta)^2}{a(a+\beta)^2} \eta ay \dots \xi.$$

(observe $2(a^2 + \beta) - a(a - \beta) = -(a + (a + \beta)) = -8a^2$ is negative)

$$= -\frac{2a^2}{a(a+\beta)^2} \eta ay \dots \xi.$$

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if $\frac{dy}{dx}$ be the value at the entropy. Writing $\frac{a^2}{a^2}$ for the element of the are we have

$$\frac{ds^2}{a^2} = \frac{dx^2(a-\beta)^2}{(a-\beta)^2} \left[1 - \frac{4}{a}\eta\right] - \frac{8a^2}{a},$$

$$\frac{ds^2}{a^2} = \frac{dx^2(-a\beta\gamma)^2}{(a-\beta)^2} - \frac{8a^2}{a},$$

which exhibit the form at the entropy.

The Nodal Curve; expressions for the coordinates in terms of a single parameter a . Art. Nos. 53 to 60.

53. After the foregoing investigation of the nodal curve, I was led to perceive that it is possible to express ξ, η, ξ_0, η_0 in terms of a single variable a ; and thus to obtain expressions for the coordinates of a point of the nodal curve in terms of the single variable a . The analytical form of the nodal curve being real, with its imaginary values of ξ, η , the modes y may we may assume

$$\xi = -b^2 - p(b^2 - a^2 - b^2), \quad \eta = -b^2 + p(b^2 - a^2 - b^2),$$

($i = \sqrt{-1}$ as usual): viz. p denote one or other of the quantities

$$y_+ = a + (a^2 - b^2), \quad q = a - (a^2 - b^2);$$

the expressions for $-\beta\gamma x^2, -\gamma ay^2$ become

$$= [(b-p)(a+1)(b-q)^3](b-p)^3,$$

and we have therefore the condition that this shall be real (for the two values $b = p, b = -b$); being real, it will in certain cases be positive, in other cases negative, and the values for the remaining condition is given by the equation

$$\Delta'(b^2 - \xi^2 - \xi_0^2 - 4)(b^2 + b^2 + \xi^2 + 2b^2)^2 + p^2(b - \xi^2 - 2)(b^2 + \xi)^2 - 0 = 0.$$

54. The condition of reality is easily found to be

$$\Delta'(b^2 - \beta\beta - \beta^2)(\beta + \beta - 1) + (a + \beta)^2 + (\gamma + p)^2 + 4(a + p)(\beta - p) + (a + p)^2(b - \beta) - p^2q^2 = 0;$$

viz. this equation in Δ must have the form $-a, b$, suppose to a value

$$\frac{(y-a)\beta}{a^2} = a + \frac{a(a^2-b^2)}{2bg(\gamma-a)}\sqrt{Y} \cdot \eta(a-\beta-\gamma)(a+\beta+\gamma),$$

where, regarding X, Y are given functions of a , the coordinates of a plane in a cubic curve having the point $X = 0, Y = 0$ for a node, writing $Y = b + 3a(X + 1)$, X will be such of these is rational function of a . The curve has the property that being any line through the entropy, the tangents at the points of the curve, the corresponding entropies on it are

$$(a^2 + Y)(a^2 + a)(a + 1) + (b + 1)(a^2 + b)\beta(a^2 + a) = -a^2(b - p)^3 + a(p + p)^3,$$

for a point on the nodal curve.

55. To complete the investigation, writing for a moment $T = 3 = 3a^2(X + 1)$, we obtain

$$\frac{(b-p)^2}{a^2} = \frac{a}{2a^2(a+a-1)} + \frac{a(a^2)(b-\xi)^3}{a+b-1},$$

or putting for a moment

$$\frac{(\gamma-a)\beta}{a^2} = K,$$

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and writing $P + Q = P, X.P = P'$, the first of these is

$$\frac{(y-p)^2}{-\beta\gamma}\beta + \frac{X(X+2)}{(X+1)^2}K - \frac{Y(X+1)\beta}{2(X+1)} + \frac{1-X}{Y+X},$$

which regarding X, Y as the coordinates of a point in a plane in a cubic curve having the point $X = 0, Y = 0$ for a node: hence writing $Y = b + 3a(X + 1)$, Y will be such of these is rational function of a . The curve has the property that being any line through the entropy, the tangents at the points of the curve, the corresponding entropies on it are

$$(a^2 + Y)(a^2 + a)(a + 1) + (b + 1)(a^2 + b)\beta(a^2 + a) = -a^2(b - p)^3 + a(p + p)^3,$$

for a point on the nodal curve.

55. To complete the investigation, writing for a moment $T = 3 = 3a^2(X + 1)$, we obtain

$$\frac{(b-p)^2}{a^2} = \frac{a}{2a^2(a+a-1)} + \frac{a(a^2)(b-\xi)^3}{a+b-1},$$

or putting for a moment

$$\frac{(\gamma - a)\beta}{a^2} = K,$$

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we have

$$\begin{aligned} X &= \frac{a(K-7)(a-1)}{a+1-K}, & X_0 &= \frac{K(a-7)(a+1)}{a+1-K}, \\ Y &= K \frac{3K(a^2-1)+2(a+1)}{a+1-K}, & Y_0 &= K \frac{3(a-1)(K-2)(a+1)}{a+1-K}, \end{aligned}$$

or substituting for K its value we have

$$K(a-1) = \frac{(a-1)^2}{ab} \left(a^2 - \frac{8aq}{(a-1)^2} \right) = -\frac{(a-1)^2}{ab} \left(a + \frac{2q}{a-1} \right) \left(a - \frac{2q}{a-1} \right),$$

$aa+1-K = -\frac{1}{ab}(a^2+1)(a+b-1)(a-p), \dots +b(a-p)$, if as before $\Omega = \beta - \gamma$, and therefore changing the sign of the radical we have the values of $\frac{x}{a}, \dots$,

56. Write for a moment,

$$\begin{aligned} \left[\Delta - \frac{1}{2}(\gamma - a) \sqrt{1 + \sqrt{\frac{2a(a-2-4\beta+2)}{a(a-2)}}} \right] - (a - 8a\beta + \sqrt{\beta})Y + B\sqrt{\delta} &= 0, \\ \left[\Delta - \frac{1}{2}(\gamma - a) \sqrt{1 + \sqrt{\frac{2a(a-2-4\beta+2)}{a(a-2)}}} \right] - (a - 8a\beta + \sqrt{\beta})Y + B\sqrt{\delta} &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

then in the product of these two expressions the rational part is $= A^2A + B^2B$; and from the manner in which they were arrived at we have $9 = A_1A + B_1B$, and the rational part is thus

$$= -\frac{16}{a^2}(B^2 - B'B).$$

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We have

$$\begin{aligned} A^2 A - B^2 B &= (\Delta - a)^2 X - 8a^2 X_0, \\ B &= \frac{1}{2}(\gamma + a)X \left[a - \frac{2aq}{(a-1)^2}(X + S) \right] - a^2 b^2 (P^2 - 2a^2), \end{aligned}$$

hence the rational part in question is

$$= \pm \frac{(\eta+a)^2}{(2a+Pp+a)} \sqrt{\frac{a+R+(1-\xi)(2+\xi)}{P\{Q+q(P+Q)-3\xi_0\}}}(2+\xi).$$

57. We have

$$\begin{aligned} 1 &= \frac{a}{2} \frac{1}{a^2(a-1)} \left[aa^2 - 2\beta - \xi \left(a^2 - \frac{4q}{(a^2-1)^2} \right) \right] \\ &\quad - \frac{1}{2} \frac{1}{(\gamma-a)^2} \left[aa^2 - 2\beta - \xi - \frac{4qa}{(a^2-1)^2} \right] + \dots, \end{aligned}$$

where the term in [] is

$$= \frac{2ag}{a^2(a^2-1)} \left[3aa^2 - 2\beta - \xi \left(a^2 - \frac{4q\eta}{(a^2-1)^2} \right) \right],$$

hence $\Delta = \frac{(\gamma-a)\beta}{(\gamma-1)} \frac{x(\beta-a)}{(y-a)} + \frac{X(\beta-y)}{(y-a)} - 2y$, where now

$$a = \frac{1}{2}(P + Q - 1)(\beta - q).$$

58. Moreover

$$(\Delta - a)^2 = -\Delta^2 - \Delta a + a^2,$$

where the term in [] is

$$= -\frac{2ag}{a^2(a^2-1)} \left[3aa^2 - 2\beta - \xi \left(a^2 - \frac{4q\eta}{(a^2-1)^2} \right) \right];$$

where on changing a into β , the coefficient of a is

$$\begin{aligned} &= \frac{2bx}{x^2} (b-1)^2 = -\frac{ab(a-b-1)(a+b)}{x^2} [3a(a-2\beta-4q\beta+8\beta(a-q+1)+8\beta(a^2-1))] \\ &\quad - \frac{a^2(b-a)}{(a^2-1)} [3aa^2+4(b-\beta)+8(\beta-q)+8(a^2-1)] + \frac{a(b+a)}{a^2(a-1)} \Sigma, \end{aligned}$$

where the last expression on a single fraction is

$$= -\frac{8ax}{a(\beta-1)^2} (b\beta-q)(a-q) \dots$$

and if we hence determine the values $3(\xi^2 - \xi_0^2) = \eta_0$, we find that the resulting terms divide by $\xi - \xi_0$, and we have

$$\begin{aligned} 3\xi_0^2(\xi_0 - \xi) - \xi^2[(b+a)\xi + 3\xi_0] &= (\xi + \xi_0)\xi_0(b+a)(\xi + \xi_0)(\xi + a) \\ &\quad + \xi_0 \dots, \\ &\quad + \xi_0 \dots. \end{aligned}$$

Hence observing that by the relation between ξ, ξ_0 , the first term is

$$= -3Q\xi_0 + (P+Q)q + 2\xi_0 q,$$

the equations become

$$\begin{aligned} 1 : \eta : \eta_0 &= -[Q + p(P+Q) - 3\xi_0] \cdot Q \\ &\quad : R(2\xi_0 + 2) - \xi^2(P+Q\xi) \\ &\quad : R(3\xi_0^2 - \xi^2) - \xi^2 P(P+Q\xi). \end{aligned}$$

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Similarly

$$\begin{aligned} & \Sigma(\Delta - a)^2 + aX\Sigma a^2(a-1)\Sigma + a^2(\Sigma + S) \\ &= \frac{a^2}{a(a-1)}[(b\beta - q)(a - q) + a(a-1)\Delta - q(b\beta - q)\Sigma\Delta + b\beta(a - q)\Sigma\Sigma - q\beta(a - q)\Sigma\Sigma], \end{aligned}$$

where the term in $\{ \}$ is

$$= -\frac{8\beta}{a^2}\eta\Delta\Sigma\eta - \frac{a^2(b-1)}{(\beta-1)}\beta\beta a\Sigma + 3\beta\Sigma(a-1)\eta - \alpha + \beta - q(\beta - q) - \beta,$$

in which the coefficient of a is $a\beta(\beta - q)\Sigma\Sigma\Sigma + 3y\eta(a - q)$, but the last is a product of these linear functions: hence

$$3(\Sigma - aB)^2 + 6\Sigma = \frac{2(a-1)}{a^2}\eta(\Sigma - q + 3\beta(a - q) - \delta(a - q) - a).$$

59. Substituting these values we have the expression

$$\frac{1}{(\beta-1)\eta\alpha} \left[\frac{(y-a)q + a(a-1)(b\beta-q) + 3a\Sigma(a-q) - 2bq + (b\beta-q)^2 - (a\Sigma)}{a\eta(\eta-a)\Sigma a(a)} \right] + 5\Sigma^2,$$

which solving therein $\Delta = -y - \beta\beta\eta y - 5\beta\eta - 5\beta\eta + \Sigma\Sigma - 5\beta\eta\eta + 4(\eta - q + 1)\Sigma\eta + \dots$, and the final results are

$$-\beta\beta z^2 = \frac{(y-a) + \delta(b\beta-q)\Sigma\Sigma + \frac{1}{5}\beta(a\Sigma) + \dots(\Sigma + q^2(\Sigma+5)(a-1))}{4y(y-1)(\beta-4)\Sigma\Sigma(a-q)},$$

which is in be observed that, equating the denominators by $\Sigma\Sigma$, we have a simple root $\Sigma\Sigma$, to indicate this, we may insert in the denominator the factor $(1 - 8\beta)$.

60. We see here the meaning of all the factors, viz. Planes.

	$a = 0$	$\beta = 0$	$c = 0$	$a = \infty$
Evolute nodes	$a = -\frac{a^2}{y-a}$	$a = -1$	$\dots$	$a = -\infty$
Umbilicar centres	$a = -\frac{2y\beta}{(\eta-\beta)^2}$	$\dots$	$\dots$	$\dots$
Entropies	$a = -\frac{a+\beta}{a+\beta}(\eta - \beta\beta)$	$\dots$	$\dots$	$\dots$

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For the real curve a extends from $\frac{a}{2b}$ through 0 to $-\frac{3a}{2b}$, viz.

$$a = -\frac{2y}{y-a}, \quad a = -1, \quad \text{gives entropy in plane } a = 0,$$

$$a = \frac{2a\beta}{y-a}, \quad \text{umbilicar centre in plane } y = 0,$$

$$a = -\frac{a+\beta}{a+\beta}(\eta - \beta), \quad \text{evolute-node in plane } a.$$

It is to be noticed that the order of magnitude of the terms in the table is

$$a, -\frac{2y}{y-a}, \quad a, \frac{2a\beta}{y-a}, \quad a, \dots,$$

$\xi \cdot \frac{2y-a+\beta-\frac{a+\beta}{a+\beta}}{(\eta+a+\beta)}$; which belong to the real curve are contiguous; this is in fact be should be: Several of the proving investigations conducted by means of this quantities ξ, ξ, ξ_0 , might have been conducted more simply by means of the formula involving a .

The Eight Cuspidal Conics. Art. Nos. 61 to 71.

61. The centro-surface is the envelope of the quadric

$$\frac{a^2 x^2}{(a+\xi)^2} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(b+\xi)^2} + \frac{c^2 z^2}{(c+\xi)^2} - 1 = 0.$$

Hence it has a cuspidal curve given by means of this equation and the first and second derived equations

$$\frac{a^2 x^2}{(a+\xi)^3} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(b+\xi)^3} + \frac{c^2 z^2}{(c+\xi)^3} = 0,$$

$$\frac{a^2 x^2}{(a+\xi)^4} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{(b+\xi)^4} + \frac{c^2 z^2}{(c+\xi)^4} = 0,$$

which equations determine $a^2, b^2 y^2, c^2 z^2$ in terms of ξ , viz. we have

$$-\beta\gamma a^2 x^2 = a^2(a+\xi)^3,$$

$$-\gamma a b^2 y^2 = b^2(b+\xi)^3,$$

$$-a\beta c^2 z^2 = c^2(c+\xi)^3;$$

so that, comparing with the equations $-\beta\gamma x^2 = a^2(a+\xi)^3(a+\eta)$, etc., which gave the centro-surface, we see that the cuspidal curve $\xi = \eta$, the cuspidal curve must be in question arises from the entire case in the ellipsoid, which form as the envelope of the curves of curvature: it is clear that the curve is imaginary.

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62. From the foregoing equations we have

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{\beta y} + \sqrt{cz} = a + \sqrt{\xi},$$

$$a\sqrt{ax} + \beta\sqrt{\beta y} + c\sqrt{cz} = a + \sqrt{\xi}\xi;$$

the second of which is best written in the rationalised form

$$(1, 1, 1, -1, -1, -1)(ax, by, cz; \beta\sqrt{\gamma y}, \sqrt{\gamma az}, \sqrt{a\beta y})^2 = ay^2,$$

and combining herewith the equation

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{\beta y} + \sqrt{cz} + \sqrt{\xi} = 0,$$

then for any given signs of $\sqrt{a}$, $\sqrt{\beta}$, $\sqrt{c}$, $\sqrt{\xi}$ the first of these equations represents a quartic surface, the second a plane; or the two equations together represent a conic.

By changing the signs of the radicals (observing that when all the four signs are changed simultaneously the curve is unaltered) we obtain in all 8 conics, but only four quartic surfaces; viz. the two conics

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{\beta y} + \sqrt{cz} = \sqrt{\xi},$$

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{\beta y} + \sqrt{cz} = -\sqrt{\xi}$$

lie on the same quartic surface.

63. The conics form two sets of four, corresponding to the two sets of four lines on the ellipsoid. The analysis seems to establish a correspondence of each conic of the one set to a single conic of the other set; viz. the conics have been obtained in pairs as the intersections of the same quadric surface by a pair of planes: there is a like correspondence of each line of the one set to a single line of the other set, viz. the lines meet in pairs on the umbilici at infinity, but this correspondence is included in a more general property: in fact each line of the one set meets each line of the other set in an umbilicus; and the corresponding conics (not only meet but) touch at the corresponding umbilicar centre; and qua touching conics they have two points of intersection, and consequently lie on the same quadric surface. It is to be added that the two conics touch also, at the umbilicar centre, the cuspidal conic of the principal section.

64. The 8 conics form two tetrads, and the principal conics (reckoning as one of them the conic at infinity) another tetrad: the complete cuspidal curve consists therefore of three tetrads of conics: with these we may form (one conic out of each tetrad) 16 triads; viz. each conic of one tetrad is combined with each conic of either of the other tetrads, and with a determinate conic of the third tetrad, to form a triad. And the conics of each triad, not only meet but touch at an umbilicar centre, the common tangent being also by what precedes, the tangent of the evolute at that point, which point is also a node of the nodal curve.

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65. But first consider the two conics

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{by} + \sqrt{cz} = \sqrt{-a\beta\gamma},$$

$$(1, 1, 1, -1, -1, -1)(ax, by, cz; \beta\sqrt{\gamma}y, \sqrt{\gamma}az, \sqrt{a\beta}y)^2 = ay^2;$$

for the intersections with the plane $y = 0$ we have

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{by} + \sqrt{cz} = \sqrt{-a\beta\gamma},$$

$$(axx - a^2x - \gamma yz)^2 = 0;$$

so that the two conics each meet the plane in question in the same two coincident points, that is, they each touch the plane $y = 0$ at the same point. The two points by the equations

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{cz} = \sqrt{-a\beta\gamma},$$

$$(axx - yz)^2 = 0;$$

viz. this is the point, $aa = \frac{-ayc}{a-\beta}$, $aa = \frac{2y\beta}{a-\beta}$, which is one of the umbilicar centres before mentioned. We have

$$(a^2 + a^2) \dots,$$

and the common tangent at this point is

$$\sqrt{ax} + \sqrt{by} + \sqrt{cz} = \sqrt{-a\beta\gamma},$$

which is also the common tangent of the ellipse and evolute in the plane $y = 0$.

66. It has been seen that the nodal curve meets each principal conic at four umbilicar centres, which form ten cusps of the nodal curve. It is to be further shown that the nodal curve meets each of the 8 cuspidal conics in the four points (giving 32 nodal points distinguished as the principal entropy) or 16 entropies, and the points now in question are cusps of the nodal curve.

67. Putting for shortness,

$$\Theta = \sqrt{1(\sqrt{\eta - q}(\eta - \beta)(\eta - 2))},$$

$$S = \frac{a(a+\beta a)}{\eta(\eta-q)}\left(\eta - \frac{2y}{\eta-a}\right),$$

we have then

$$\Theta(1 + a\Theta)\Delta = -\sqrt{ax}.$$

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or, what is the same thing,

$$\Theta(1 + 3S) - 1 + a\sqrt{\Sigma}(2 + S - 2) = 0.$$

we have without difficulty

$$\begin{aligned}\Theta(1 + S) + 1 &= \frac{1}{2(\eta-q)}[3a^2 - 4a + 4 + \frac{8\eta q}{(\eta-q)^2}], \\ \Theta(1 + 2 + \Theta) - 1 &= \frac{1}{2(\eta-q)}\left[\frac{2(\eta-1)\beta+2y(\eta+\beta-q)}{(\eta-q)} - \frac{4(\beta q+\beta\eta)}{(\eta-q)^2}\right];\end{aligned}$$

Omitting it, the equation becomes

$$\sqrt{a^2 - \beta - \frac{2y}{(\eta-q)\eta}} \sqrt{a^2 - \frac{(2)\eta-4\beta+\frac{1}{2}}{(\eta-q)}} \left(\eta - 4\eta + 4\eta + \frac{2}{(\eta-q)}\right) = 0,$$

or putting for shortness

$$\begin{aligned}\sqrt{a^2 - \beta - \frac{2y}{(\eta-q)\eta}} &= M, \text{ and rationalising, this is} \\ &= (\sigma - 2 - M)(\Sigma\eta - 2) + 4y\Sigma + 4(\Sigma - 1)\end{aligned}$$

and, working this out, the terms in Σ disappear, and we have for the resulting terms divide by $\Sigma - 2$, and we have

$$8 : a = \dots = -P\Sigma\beta + 4(\Sigma + \beta + 3\Sigma - 4)\Sigma + 8M,$$

a quartic equation in a : each of the 4 roots there correspond 8 intersections, viz. there will be in all 32 intersections, lying in 4's upon the 8 cuspidal conics.

68. To start from these points are cusps, or stationary points on the nodal curve, starting from the expression of $-\beta\gamma z^3$ etc. in terms of a we have, first for δx , the equations

$$\frac{\delta x}{x} = \frac{a}{a-\beta+1} \delta a + \frac{4}{a+1} \delta a + \frac{2(\eta-\beta)}{(a+\beta+a)(\sqrt{\Sigma}-q+\beta+a)} \delta a,$$

so, as this may be written,

$$\begin{aligned}\frac{\delta x}{x} &= \frac{a(2a+4(a+1)\beta-q(a+1)-\beta)\eta(\Sigma+M+2a-2P)+(M+3\eta)\eta-4a+M}{a(a+1)(\beta-1)\Sigma a\eta-q(a)} \\ &\quad - \frac{\alpha\Sigma[5+5\Sigma(\frac{1}{2}(a+8\eta+9\Sigma)+\frac{1}{2}(3M-8\Sigma\eta\Sigma)+\frac{1}{2}(3M(a+4\eta+a)+\Sigma-2\Sigma a+a+\beta))]}{a(a+1)(\Sigma\eta-q)\Sigma\Sigma a(a-q)}\end{aligned}$$

viz. the numerator vanishes when a is a root of the quartic equation.

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69. We have moreover

$$-\frac{2\delta y}{y} da = \frac{1}{\eta\eta(\eta-q)} \left[a + \frac{2\eta}{(\eta-a)(\eta-q)} + \frac{2a(\eta-q+a)}{(\eta-a)} + \frac{2(a-q)}{(\eta-a)} - \Omega \frac{6}{a} \right],$$

which, putting $\frac{\eta-q+a}{\eta-q} = R$, and therefore $\frac{a-q}{\eta-q} = R-1$, $a = \frac{\Omega}{\eta-q} - C$, is

$$= \frac{1}{2} \left[\frac{1}{a+R} + \frac{1}{R} - 2R + \frac{2R}{\eta-q} \cdot \frac{4}{\eta-q} \cdot \frac{M+8\eta\beta}{q} + \frac{6}{\eta-q} \right];$$

and adding the fractions inside of $\{ \}$, the numerator is

$$a(PR + 5G\Omega - R) + \dots$$

$$= \frac{2}{\eta} a(\eta + a + 1)(\eta + 5G + 7\eta + 3G\beta) - 6G + (\eta + 5G + 7\eta + 4G)\Omega - 96b\beta\beta + 8G,$$

which observing that $R = 2 + a$, is $= 8M + 16\beta\beta$, and, substituting for M and R their values, this is

$$= a^2(7M + 5R) + (3M + 8\beta) + (\beta + 5G + 2\eta + a) + 8\beta M,$$

and substituting, the whole denominator is $1 \cdot 8M$, so that, as the result of the equation

$$8M = a^4 - 3M(\eta + 5G + 2\eta + a) - 8\beta M,$$

we may have

$$-\frac{2\delta y}{y} da = \frac{4(2\eta-1)(\eta+a+1)}{(\eta-q)\eta} \left[a + \frac{2\eta}{(\eta-q)} \right] + \frac{a}{\eta+a+2}.$$

and the numerator of the expression on a single fraction is

$$= \frac{4(2\eta+a)^2}{(\eta-q)^2\eta^2} a(\eta + \frac{2y\Sigma}{\eta(\eta-q)} a + a) \beta(\eta - 4M) \dots,$$

which is

$$= 5(\eta + 5G + \eta + \beta) + 8\Omega(\eta + aM + 8\beta a + a) - 24\Omega(\eta + aM + 5\beta\eta + aM),$$

which is

$$= a\beta = -3M(\eta + 3G + \eta + 8\beta + a + 5\beta) + \frac{4(2\eta+a)}{(\eta-q)^2\eta} a(3M + 5G + 7\eta + 4G);$$

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the term in [] is

$$\begin{aligned}
 &= a^2(7M + 5R) + B + 8 \frac{a+\beta a}{(\eta-q)\eta} \sigma \\
 &= a + 2(M + 8R) + 8 \frac{a+\beta \eta}{(\eta-q)\eta} (a - 8a + \beta a + a) \\
 &\quad + 2[3M\beta + 8\eta M \frac{a+\beta \eta}{(\eta-q)\eta} (P + 2\beta\beta + 4G\Omega\eta) \\
 &- 8M = a \sqrt{a^2(11M + 5R) + 5R(a^2 - 5R) + 5\Sigma + 5R\beta + 5\Omega M},
 \end{aligned}$$

which is found to be

$$= -8a\Omega + a^2(11M + 5R) + B \cdot \beta + \beta M;$$

and the whole numerator is

$$= 8a\Omega^2 + a^2(11M + 5R) + B \cdot \beta + \beta M,$$

which is

$$= (16 + 5R)a + 5R(a^2 - 5R) + 5M + 4P\beta + 4M.$$

71. We have then

$$-\frac{2\delta y}{y da} = \frac{1\eta(R+6\Sigma\beta)(\eta+a) - \frac{5G+2\eta+a}{(\eta-q)^2} a + 5RM - 16M^2(\beta+R)\eta + \frac{1\eta}{a+1\beta} \beta + 16M\eta + 5R}{(\eta-q)^2 \eta \beta (\eta-q)},$$

and theme also

$$\frac{2\delta y}{y da} \left(\frac{a+\beta}{\eta-q} \right) \Omega + \frac{(2\eta+a)(2\eta+a)(\eta+a+a+1)}{(\eta-q)\eta\beta} \sigma + \frac{a+\beta}{(\eta-q)} \left(a \frac{a}{a-q} \right)$$

so that δx do also vanish when a is a root of the quartic equation, the points in question are therefore cusps of the nodal curve.

Centro-surface as the envelope of quartic $\Sigma a^2 = \beta + 1 = 0$. Art. Nos. 72 to 76.

72. The equations $-\beta\gamma x^2 = a^2(a + \xi)^3(a + \eta)$, etc., considering therein ξ, η as variable parameters connected by the equation $\xi - \eta$ as a given constant value, give the equation of the sequential centro-curve, and considering ξ as a given constant but η as variable they give the constant centro-curve.

73. Suppose first that η is a given constant; to eliminate ξ we may write the equations in the form

$$-(\beta\gamma\sqrt{a} = a^2(a + \xi)^{3/2}(a + \eta)^{1/2}, \text{ etc.},$$

and then multiplying first by $a^{-3/2}, b^{-3/2}, c^{-3/2}$, and adding, and secondly by b, c, a , and adding, (observing that $\Sigma(\sqrt{a}) = 0, \Sigma(\sqrt{a}\sqrt{b}) = 0$), we obtain

$$\Sigma(ax)\sqrt{a^2 + a + b} = -a\sqrt{a + b},$$

$$\Sigma(\beta ax)\sqrt{a^2 + a + b} = -a(a + b\sqrt{a + \eta}\beta),$$

which equations, considering therein a as a given constant, are the equations of a sequential centro-curve.

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If from the two equations we eliminate a we should have the equation of the centro-surface; the second equation is the derivative of the first in regard to η ; and it thus appears that the equation of the surface can be obtained by considering η in the first equation as a variable parameter. The equation of the centro-surface is thus

$$\sum (\overline{ax})^2 (a + \eta)^4 = (-a\beta\gamma)^2.$$

but the form is less convenient to that of
The above equation is, multiplying by b, c, a , and adding, by b, c, a , and adding, by b^2, c^2, a^2 , and adding,

$$3a^2 \cdot ab^2 + 3ab^2c^2 + ab^2\overline{ax^2} = -a\beta\gamma \cdot \sqrt{(a + \eta)\beta} \cdot ab,$$

and, eliminating η , we have the equation in the form before mentioned (last paragraph).

74. Taking now ξ as a given constant, and writing the equation in the form

$$\sqrt{a} \cdot \overline{ax^2} = a^2(a + \xi)^{3/2} \cdot (a + \eta)^{1/2}, \text{ etc.,}$$

then multiplying by $\beta\gamma, \gamma a, a\beta$, and adding, and secondly by bc, ca, ab , and adding, or writing this for the sake of distinction

$$\sqrt{a} \cdot \overline{ax^2} = a^2\beta^{3/2}(a + \xi)^{1/2}, \text{ etc.,}$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} \sum (\overline{ax})^2 (a + \xi)^{1/2} &= a + \xi, \\ \sum (\overline{ax})^2 (a + \xi)^{1/2} &= a + \xi + b + \xi, \end{aligned}$$

or writing these equations in full form

$$\sqrt{a^2(a + \xi)^2 + b^2(b + \xi)^2 + c^2(c + \xi)^2 + \delta} - \delta + \xi = 0,$$

$$\sqrt{a^2(a + \xi)^2 + b^2(b + \xi)^2 + c^2(c + \xi)^2 + \delta} - 4 + \xi - 1 = 0,$$

thus the coefficients on the second side are $(a, x, y, z, ax, by, cz, a^2)$, the first quadrilateral. The second equation as the derivative of the first in regard to ξ , a, z , etc., as the first quadrilateral. The second equation as the derivative of the second in regard to ξ , a, z , etc., as a function of a in this way evidently a twofold factor $(1 + \frac{1}{\xi})^2$, viz. this is, the centro-surface is the envelope of a sequence of quartic surfaces, each of which lies entirely the centro-surface. The numerical results were not made out, but my own. (see "On a certain Sextic Form," *Camb. Phil. Trans. t. xx* (1871), pp. 397–523, [486].)

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Another generation of the Centro-surface. Art. Nos. 77 to 83.

77. It may precede, the equation of the centro-surface is obtained as the condition in order that the equation

$$\sum (ax) \sqrt{a + \eta - 1} = 0$$

may have equal roots. But taking a as arbitrary constant, this is the derived equation of

$$\sum a(ax)^2(a + \eta) = a + \eta + ax,$$

and as such it will have two equal roots if the last-mentioned equation has the property of expressing that the last-mentioned equation, or what is the same thing, the quartic equation

$$(a + \eta) + a(ax)^2 + a(b + \eta) + a(b + \eta)^2 + (a(a + \eta) + a(a + \eta))^2 = 0,$$

has three equal roots. The condition for this are that the discriminant and the subdiscriminant shall each of them vanish, and we have thus the equations to be considered as respectively a quadric and a cubic function of a ; viz. the equations

$$\langle a, h, h \xi \rangle (a, b, c, d, e)^4 = 0$$

$$\langle a, h, h \xi \rangle (a, b, c, d, e)^4 = 0$$

where the degrees in (x, y, z) of a, b, c, d, e are 0, 2, 4, 6 and those of a', b', c', d' are 2, 4, 6, 8 respectively; the equation of the centro-surface is then

$$\begin{vmatrix} a & b & c & d & e \\ a' & b' & c' & d' & e' \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

which is of the right order 12; but it would be difficult to obtain thereby the developed equation.

78. For the nodal curve the cubic equation must be satisfied by each root of the quadric equation, or that is the same thing, the quadric function must contain as a factor

$$\langle a, b, c \rangle \langle a, b', c', d' \rangle = 0,$$

whose the degrees may be taken as below, viz.

$$\langle 0, 2, 4 \rangle \langle 0, 2, 4 \rangle = 0.$$

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and the order of the nodal curve is then = 24: two of the equations in fact are

$$\begin{vmatrix} a & b & e \\ a' & b' & e' \end{vmatrix} = 0, \quad \begin{vmatrix} a & b & e \\ a' & b' & e' \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

which are surfaces of the orders 4, 6, etc.; or the nodal curve is a complete intersection $\Sigma \times 6$. By the results above obtained as to the nodal curve, it appears that the two surfaces must have an ordinary contact at each of the 16 umbilicar centres, and a stationary or singular contact at each of the 32 entropies.

79. The derivation of the centro-surface from the surface

$$\frac{a^2}{a^2 + \xi} X^2 + \frac{b^2}{b^2 + \xi} Y^2 + \frac{c^2}{c^2 + \xi} Z^2 - U^2 = 0$$

requires to be further explained. The surface, say $V = 0$, is a quadric surface depending on the two parameters ξ, η ; the same outside in direction with these of the ellipsoid, and their relative magnitudes obey the equation

$$\frac{1}{a^2 + \xi} X^2 + \frac{1}{b^2 + \xi} Y^2 + \frac{1}{c^2 + \xi} Z^2 = 1$$

divided by a, b, c respectively; viz. for the absolute magnitudes observe that the equation may be written

$$\frac{a^2 - \xi^2}{a^2 + \xi} X^2 + \frac{b^2 - \xi^2}{b^2 + \xi} Y^2 + \frac{c^2 - \xi^2}{c^2 + \xi} Z^2 - 1 = 0,$$

viz. the surface $V = 0$ is a surface through the spheroconic which is the intersection of the conduit surface by the arbitrary sphere $a^2 + b^2 + c^2 + U^2 = 0$: but, while the surface is hereby and by the preceding condition as to the axes completely determined, the geometrical significance is anything but clear.

80. Considering then the quartic surface $V = 0$, depending on the parameters ξ, η , suppose that a remains constant while ξ alone varies; we have then consecutive surfaces $V = 0, V_1 = 0$, which on of these V_1 say intersect in a point of the centro-surface; the point in question will depend on the two parameters (ξ, η) , and if these vary simultaneously we have thus a whole series of points on the centro-surface, but it may simultaneously be that there belong to the locus of points or the centro-surface. To make this evident, we must inquire that, that proceeding by both a being also along the value of η values of a which are not for which lines and the variable centres are imaginary by means of points on the centro-surface, it is the quadric superceded as ξ, η , to satisfy the equation of the centro-surface; thus the form of the line of corresponding to the difference of the nodal curve, but it is shown of curvature for the parameter η .

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the variable parameter be ξ , then this is a curve on the 12-fold surface $\Omega = 0$ obtained by the elimination of ξ from the equations $V = 0, \delta_\xi V = 0$; viz. we have $\delta_\xi V$ as the curve in question on the surface. The equation of the curve is the elimination of a as from the two equations $S = 0, T = 0$ gives as above the equation of the centro-surface.

81. The surface $\Omega = \delta - T = 0$ obtained as shown by the elimination of ξ from the equations $V = 0, \delta_\xi V = 0$, (or, what is the same thing, by equating to zero the discriminant of V in regard to ξ) may be termed the sociate-surface: we have there this quartic and sociate surfaces $S = 0, T = 0$ intersecting in the before-mentioned curve, which we call the sociate-edge; and the locus of these sociate-edges is the centro-surface.

82. We may if we please, changing the parameter in case of the functions, consider the two series of surfaces $S = 0, T = 0$ depending on the parameters a, a' respectively; a surface of the first series will correspond to a curve of the second series for the parameter a equal, say we have two surfaces of equal, a' , and have these to a sociate-edge: taking a, a' as the parameters of the two surfaces a, a in nearly equal, we have the locus of these sociate-edges is the centro-surface.

83. We may by what precedes, changing the parameter in case of the functions, consider the two series of surfaces $S = 0, T = 0$ depending on the parameters a, a' respectively; a surface of the first series will correspond to a curve of the second series for the parameter a equal, say we have two surfaces of equal, a' , and have these to a sociate-edge: taking a, a' as the parameters of the two surfaces a, a in nearly equal, we have the locus of these sociate-edges is the centro-surface.

a posteriori verification that the surfaces $V = 0, V' = 0, V'' = 0$ intersect in a point of the centro-surface, can be made without interest; the parameters ξ_1, η of the point of intersection being constant to be of the order η ; whence, starting from the variation of η , we indefinitely small in regard to those arising from the variation of ξ , we ought therefore to have identically

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{-a(a^2 + \xi_0)\xi'(a^2 + \eta_0)}{a^2 + \xi} &= \delta\xi(a^2 + \xi_0) - \eta_0 - \eta - \beta - \delta' \\ &= \frac{a\eta(\xi - \xi_0)\sqrt{(a^2 + \eta_0)}}{(a^2 + \xi)\sqrt{(a^2 + \eta_0)\xi'}} \end{aligned}$$

and by decomposing the right-hand side into its component fractions this is at once seen to be true.

Third generation of the Centro-surface. Art. Nos. 84 and 85.

84. Instead of the foregoing equation $V = 0$, consider the equation

$$W = \left(\frac{a^2 x^2}{a^2 + \xi} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{b^2 + \xi} + \frac{c^2 z^2}{c^2 + \xi} + \frac{w^2}{\xi} \right) - \left(\frac{a^2 x^2}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{b^2 y^2}{b^2 + \eta} + \frac{c^2 z^2}{c^2 + \eta} + \frac{w^2}{\eta} \right) = 0.$$

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The equations $\delta_\xi W = 0, \delta_\eta W = 0$ contain only ξ and η respectively; the surface is therefore the envelope of $a^2 - 4xy = 0$; the elimination of ξ from the equations $\delta_\xi W = 0, \delta_\eta W = 0$ would therefore lead to the equation of the centro-surface as before. But the equation $W = 0$ contains a factor of three of the equations $V = 0, \delta_\xi V = 0, \delta_\eta V = 0$, viz. to fix the ideas, $W = 0$ is connected with the equation $V = 0$ as above given by the elimination of ξ from the equation $W = 0$ depending only on ξ , we have ξ in regard to the value of ξ and in the regard to the value of η in the same equation; and we have the same equation $W = 0$ depending only on ξ ; or showing that the determination of ξ, η by an equation of ξ form is connected.

$$(a^2 + \xi)(a^2 + \eta) + \frac{\xi y_0^2}{a^2 + \eta} + \frac{\xi y_0^2}{(a^2 + \xi)^2(a^2 + \eta)^2} = 1 - 0,$$

so that the surface $\Omega = 0$ is obtained by eliminating ξ from this equation as the several points of the curve of curvature belonging to the parameter η ; viz. regarding ξ as the variable parameter on the ellipsoid, then there is on the centro-surface the curve which is the value of ξ as belongs to the ellipsoid, then this is the curve which is the value of ξ as belongs to the ellipsoid; or, in a like manner, to the locus of the sociate edges is the centro-surface.

85. As ξ is constant the curve of of the centro-surface for points moved at distance a^2 in the curve, viz. in the same way, but as on the cone a may be reduced to a twofold form $(1 + \frac{1}{\xi})^2$, if $w^2 = 0$, and it has evidently a twofold factor on each side of the various contains the planes (when a has any other value), but it must necessarily form quartic surface envelope of the sphere (whose other generator ξ) which has the points (one or eight equal to the centre).

Reciprocal Surface. Art. No. 86.

86. The centro-surface is the envelope of

$$\frac{a^2 X^2}{a^2 + \xi} + \frac{b^2 Y^2}{b^2 + \xi} + \frac{c^2 Z^2}{c^2 + \xi} - W^2 = 0;$$

hence the reciprocal surface is the envelope of $a^2 + y^2 + z^2 + w^2 = 0$ in regard to

$$\frac{(a^2 + \xi)x^2}{a^2} + \frac{(b^2 + \xi)y^2}{b^2} + \frac{(c^2 + \xi)z^2}{c^2} - w^2 = 0,$$

that is,

$$a^2 x^2 + b^2 y^2 + c^2 z^2 + a^2 y^2 - 0,$$

viz. the envelope is

$$(a^2 x^2 + b^2 y^2 + c^2 z^2)(x^2 + y^2 + z^2) = w^2(a^2 + b^2 + c^2) - x^2 + y^2 + z^2 - X^2 = 0,$$

or, expanding and multiplying by $a^2 b^2 c^2$, this is

$$a^2 b^2 c^2 (a^2 + y^2 + z^2)(a^2 X^2 + b^2 Y^2 + c^2 Z^2) = w^4 (a^2 X^2 + b^2 Y^2 + c^2 Z^2) - a^2 b^2 c^2 (a^2 X^2 + b^2 Y^2 + c^2 Z^2) w^2,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$a^2 b^2 c^2 V_X X^2 + b^2 c^2 a^2 V_Y Y^2 + c^2 a^2 b^2 V_Z Z^2 X^2 + c^2 a^2 b^2 V_W W^2 + a^2 b^2 c^2 + \dots = 0,$$

which may be written,

$$a^2 X(a^2 b^2 + b^2 c^2 + c^2 a^2) \cdot X^2 + (a^2 b^2 c^2 - X^2) a^2 W^2 = 0,$$

that is,

$$(a, b, c, 1) (X^2, Y^2, Z^2, W^2)^2 = 0,$$

and, consequently,

$$a^2 + b^2 + c^2 - W^2 - a^2 b^2 c^2 + (a^2 b^2 + b^2 c^2 + c^2 a^2) - a^2 b^2 c^2 = 0,$$

It would doubtless be interesting to discuss this surface as it here presents itself, and with reference to the geometrical significance as the locus of the pole, in regard to the sphere, of the plane through the intersecting consecutive normals of the ellipsoid; but I abstain from any consideration of the question.

Delineation of the centro-surface for given numerical values of the constants. Art. Nos. 87 and 88.

87. I constructed on a large scale a drawing of the centro-surface for the values

$$a^2 = 50, \quad b^2 = 25, \quad c^2 = 15.$$

(These were chosen so that a, b, c should have approximately the integer values 7, 5, 4, and so that $a^2 + b^2$ should be well greater than $2b^2$; they give a good form of surface,

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though perhaps a better selection might have been made; there is a slight objection to the existence of the relation $b^2 = 25$, as in the xy -section it brings a cusp of the evolute on the ellipse.) We have therefore

$$a = 10, \quad \beta = -35, \quad \gamma = 25;$$

the ellipses in the principal planes of the centro-surface are

$$\frac{x^2}{(2.988)^2} + \frac{z^2}{(1.380)^2} = 1, \quad \frac{x^2}{(1.127)^2} + \frac{y^2}{(1.947)^2} = 1,$$

$$\frac{x^2}{(4.950)^2} + \frac{y^2}{(2)^2} = 1,$$

$$\frac{x^2}{(2.582)^2} + \frac{z^2}{(5.535)^2} = 1,$$

and these determine on each axis the two points which are the cusps of the evolutes. We have moreover for the umbilicar centre $x = 2.988$, $y = 0$, $z = 1.380$, and for the outcrop $x = 1.127$, $y = 1.947$, $z = 0$.

88. For the delineation of the nodal curve (crunodal portion) we have first to find the values of ξ, ξ_1 ; these are given in terms of x, y ante No. 33 [p. 334], where y is a given function of x , and x extends between the values $-b^2$ and $-\frac{1}{3}(a^2 + b^2 + c^2)$, that is between -25 and $-26\frac{2}{3}$. It was thought sufficient to divide the interval into 6 equal parts, that is, the values of x were taken to be $-25, -25\frac{1}{3}, \dots, -26\frac{2}{3}$. The values of ξ, ξ_1 being found, those of η, η_1 were obtained from them by means of the original equations

$$(a^2 + \xi)^3(a^2 + \eta) = (a^2 + \xi_1)^3(a^2 + \eta_1), \quad \&c.$$

viz. we have thus for the determination of η, η_1 three simple equations, affording a verification of each other.

For the performance of these calculations (viz. of the values of $y, \xi, \xi_1, \eta, \eta_1$) I am indebted to the kindness of Mr J. W. L. Glaisher, of Trinity College. The results being obtained it is then easy to calculate as well the coordinates (x, y, z) of the point on the nodal curve as also the coordinates (X, Y, Z) and (X_1, Y_1, Z_1) of the corresponding two points on the ellipsoid (these last are of course not required for the delineation of the nodal curve, but it was interesting to obtain them). The whole series of the results is given in the annexed Table, and from them the drawing was constructed.

I find also in the neighbourhood of the umbilicar centre (if $\xi = -25 + q$),

$$\delta x = -0.02868q^2,$$

$$\delta y = \pm 0.02484q,$$

$$\delta z = -0.02191q^2,$$

and in the neighbourhood of the outcrop (if $\xi = -38.333 + \varpi$),

$$\delta x = 1.127\varpi,$$

$$\delta y = -1.704\varpi,$$

$$\delta z = \pm 4.582\varpi^2.$$

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x	y	ξ	ξ_1	η	η_1	x	y	z	X	Y	Z	X_1	Y_1	Z_1
-25	0	-25	-25	-25	-25	2.988	0	1.380	5.326	0	2.070	5.326	0	2.070
$-25\frac{1}{3}$	4.2669	-21.0664	-29.6002	-38.3193	-16.6728	2.543	0.360	0.996	4.394	2.289	2.491	6.233	1.957	1.023
$-25\frac{2}{3}$	6.3191	-19.3475	-31.9858	-42.9911	-15.4693	2.148	0.721	0.662	3.504	3.189	2.283	5.956	2.580	0.584
-26	8.1240	-17.8760	-34.1240	-45.7879	-15.1047	1.786	1.175	0.373	2.780	3.847	1.948	5.626	3.005	0.293
$-26\frac{1}{3}$	9.8760	-16.4573	-36.2094	-47.5684	-15.0106	1.448	1.500	0.139	2.159	4.391	1.426	5.251	3.346	0.098
$-26\frac{2}{3}$	11.6667	-15.0000	-38.3333	-48.7037	-15.0000	1.127	1.947	0	1.610	4.869	0	4.829	3.651	0

The calculations were performed before I had obtained the formulae in σ , which would have given the results more easily.

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**On Dr Wiener's Model of a Cubic Surface with 27 Real Lines; and on the
Construction of a Double-Sixer.**

[From the Transactions of the Cambridge Philosophical Society, vol. XII. Part 1. (1878), pp. 366–383. Read May 15, 1871.]

I.

I CALL to mind that a cubic surface has upon it in general 27 lines which may be all of them real. We may out of the 27 lines (and that in 36 different ways) select 12 lines forming a “double-sixer,” viz. denoting such a system of lines by

$$\begin{array}{cccccc} a_1, & a_2, & a_3, & a_4, & a_5, & a_6, \\ b_1, & b_2, & b_3, & b_4, & b_5, & b_6; \end{array}$$

then no two lines a meet each other, nor any two lines b , but each line a meets each line b , except that the two lines of a pair $(a_1, b_1), (a_2, b_2), \dots, (a_6, b_6)$ do not meet each other. And such a system of twelve lines leads at once to the remaining fifteen lines; viz. we have a line c_{12} , the intersection of the planes which contain the pairs of lines (a_1, b_2) and (a_2, b_1) respectively.

The model is formed of plaster, and is contained within a cube, the edge of which is = 18.2 inches: the lines a, b, c are coloured blue, yellow, and red respectively; the lines a_1, b_2, b_5 being at right angles to each other, in such wise that taking the origin at the centre of the cube, the axes parallel to the edges, and the unit of length = 1.6 inches, the equations of these three lines are

$$\begin{array}{lll} a_1, & x = 0, & y = 0, \\ b_2, & x = 0, & z = 1, \\ b_5, & y = 0, & z = -1. \end{array}$$

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521. ON DR. WIENER'S MODEL OF A CUBIC SURFACE WITH 27 REAL LINES; AND ON THE CONSTRUCTION OF A DOUBLE-SIXER.

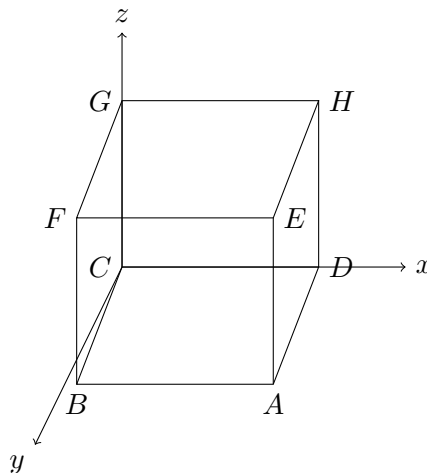
The model is a solid figure bounded by portions of the faces of the cube, and by a portion of the cubic surface, being a surface with three apertures, the collocation of which is not easily explained.

To determine the construction I measured, on the faces of the cube, the coordinates of the two extremities of each of the twelve lines; these were measured in tenths of an inch (taking account of the half division, or twentieth of an inch), and the resulting numbers divided by 16 to reduce them to the before-mentioned unit of 1.6 inches. These reduced values are shewn in the table: knowing then the coordinates of two points on each line, the equations of the several lines became calculable; the true theoretical form of these results—viz. the form which, but for errors of the model, or of the measurement, they would have assumed—is

$$\begin{aligned}
 b_1, \quad x &= B_1z + D, & y &= B'_1z + D', \\
 b_2, \quad x &= 0, & z &= 1, \\
 b_3, \quad x &= B_3(z + \beta_3), & y &= B'_3(z + \beta_3), \\
 b_4, \quad x &= B_4(z + \beta_4), & y &= B'_4(z + \beta_4), \\
 b_5, \quad y &= 0, & z &= -1, \\
 b_6, \quad x &= B_6(z + \beta_6), & y &= B'_6(z + \beta_6), \\
 a_1, \quad x &= 0, & y &= 0, \\
 a_2, \quad x &= A_2z + C_2, & y &= A'_2(z - 1), \\
 a_3, \quad x &= A_3(z + 1), & y &= A'_3(z - 1), \\
 a_4, \quad x &= A_4(z + 1), & y &= A'_4(z - 1), \\
 a_5, \quad x &= A_5(z + 1), & y &= A'_5z + C'_5, \\
 a_6, \quad x &= A_6(z + 1), & y &= A'_6(z - 1);
 \end{aligned}$$

but in consequence of such errors, the results are not accurately of the form in question.

The faces of the cube being as in the diagram:



the Table is as follows.

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Equations calculated from the measurements of the model, with
endpoint data on the faces of the cube.

Line	Calculated equation	First face data	Second face data	Additional face data
a_1	$x = 0, y = 0$	$ABCD : z = -5.688$	$EFGH : z = +5.688$	
a_2	$x = -0.780z - 0.187, y = -0.423z + 0.406$	$ABCD : x = 4.250, y = 0$	$EFGH : x = -4.625, y = 0$	
a_3	$x = -0.654z - 0.656, y = -0.588z + 0.531$	$ABCD : x = 3.062, y = 3.875$	$EFGH : x = -4.375, y = -2.812$	
a_4	$x = -2.912z - 2.959, y = -0.736z + 0.752$	$CDGH : z = 0.9375, y = -0.0625$	$AEDH : z = -2.969, y = 2.937$	
a_5	$x = 1.024z + 1.014, y = -1.049z - 0.277$	$ABCD : x = -4.812, y = 5.688$	$AEDH : y = -5.063, z = 4.562$	
a_6	$x = -0.264z - 0.187, y = -0.104z + 0.219$	$ABCD : x = -1.313, y = -0.8125$	$EFGH : x = 1.687, y = -0.375$	
b_1	$x = -1.611z + 0.151, y = -1.438z - 0.288$	$CDGH : y = 5.500, z = -3.625$	$AEDH : y = -4.656, z = 3.437$	
b_2	$x = 0, z = -1$	$AEBF : x = 0$	$BCFG : x = 0$	
b_3	$x = -1.352z - 0.685, y = -2.034z - 0.984$	$AEBF : z = 3.750, y = -3.281$	$BCFG : x = -3.812, z = 2.313$	
b_4	$x = -0.753z - 0.0315, y = -0.500z - 0.0315$	$ABCD : x = 4.250, y = 2.812$	$EFGH : x = -4.313, y = -2.875$	
b_5	$y = 0, z = 1$	$CDGH : x = 1, y = 0$	$AEDH : y = 0$	
b_6	$x = 1.123z - 0.702, y = -1.123z + 0.702$	$AEBF : x = -5.688, z = -4.438$	$BCFG : y = 0$	$AEDH : y = -5.688$

I hence calculate the intersections: considering any two lines which ought to intersect, then projecting on the horizontal plane and calculating x, y , the coordinates

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of the point of intersection of the two projections, these values of x, y substituted in the equations should give the same value of z ; but if the lines do not accurately intersect, then the values of z will be different.

	b_1	b_2	b_3	b_4	b_5	b_6
a_1	*	0, -1 0	0 0	0 0	0 0	0.398
a_2	+0.077 +.455	*	+0.381 +.771 .495 + .011	+4.292 +2.803 .052 + .010	-.967 -.008 + .008 +1	+.625 +.227 .673
a_3	-.129 + .013 .423	.001 + .001 -1	*	-4.782 -3.227 -5.704 + .036	+1 .028 + .028	+.346 + .076 +.344
a_4	+0.699 +.264 + .021	+1.119 -1	+1.286 +1.736	*	-5.871 +1 +.008 + .008	1.330 +.162 + .146
a_5	+0.957 +1.238 +.194	-.023 + .023 +1.488 .038 + .038	-1.398 + .060 +.282 +.045	+0.412 .131 +.451	*	18.764 14.155
a_6	+0.214 +.040 + .022	-1 +.323	+0.283 .582 + .042	+0.284 .423 + .208	-.057 + .057 -1	*

Starting from the assumed equations of $b_2, b_3, b_4, b_5, b_6, a_1$, and calculating by the theory the remaining lines, the equations of the b -lines (those of b_1 being calculated) are

$$\begin{aligned}
 b_1, \quad x &= 1.321z - .310, & y &= -1.295z + .581, \\
 b_2, \quad x &= 0, & z &= -1, \\
 b_3, \quad x &= -1.352(z + .510), & y &= -2.034(z + .510), \\
 b_4, \quad x &= -.753(z + .052), & y &= -.500(z + .052), \\
 b_5, \quad y &= 0, & z &= 1, \\
 b_6, \quad x &= 1.123(z - .624), & y &= -1.123(z - .624).
 \end{aligned}$$

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and the equations of the a -lines (those of all but a_1 being calculated) are

$$\begin{aligned}
 a_1, \quad x &= 0, & y &= 0, \\
 a_2, \quad x &= -.753z - .091, & y &= -.498(z - 1), \\
 a_3, \quad x &= -.609(z + 1), & y &= -.677(z - 1), \\
 a_4, \quad x &= -2.506(z + 1), & y &= -.841(z - 1), \\
 a_5, \quad x &= .874(z + 1), & y &= -.967z - .288, \\
 a_6, \quad x &= .170(z + 1), & y &= -.071(z - 1).
 \end{aligned}$$

and thence for the points of intersection the coordinates are

	b_1	b_2	b_3	b_4	b_5	b_6
a_1	*	-1 0	0 0	0 0 + .197	0 0	.336 0
a_2	-.170 +.446	*	-.510 -1 +.662 +.996	nearly parallel a_2, b_4	-.844 +1 0	+.624 +.336
a_3	+.105 -.515	-1 0	*	+1.31 -.262 -1.805	+1 0	-1.218 +.325 -.641
a_4	+.782 -.155 -1.071	+1.354 -1 0	+1.438 -1.574 +2.164	*	-5.012 +1 0	-.053 -1.259 +1.259
a_5	.573 +1.323 +3.189 -2.849 +2.649	-1 0 +.679	.702 +.259 +.291	.561 +.383 +.255	*	-6.410 +6.410 +6.333
a_6	+.241 +.041 +.417	-1 +.142	-.074 +.112	+.131 +.087	+.340 0 +1	*

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II.

I have in a paper “On the double-sixers of a cubic surface,” *Quart. Math. Journal*, t. x. (1870), pp. 58–71, [459], obtained analytical expressions for the twelve lines of a double-sixer, and also calculated numerical values, which however (as there remarked) did not come out convenient ones for the construction of a figure. A different mode of treatment since occurred to me, by means of the following equation of the cubic surface

$$\left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \left(\frac{xz}{\alpha\gamma} - \frac{yw}{\beta\delta}\right) - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} + \frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \left(\frac{xz}{\alpha'\gamma'} - \frac{yw}{\beta'\delta'}\right) = 0,$$

which as will appear is a very convenient one for the purpose. We in fact obtain at once eight lines of the double-sixer; viz. these are

$$\begin{array}{ll} 1. & x = 0, w = 0, \\ 3. & y = 0, z = 0, \\ 5. & \frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} = 0, \quad \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta} = 0, \\ 6. & \frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} = 0, \quad \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'} = 0, \\ 2'. & x = 0, y = 0, \\ 4'. & z = 0, w = 0, \\ 5'. & \frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{w}{\delta'} = 0, \quad \frac{y}{\beta'} - \frac{z}{\gamma'} = 0, \\ 6'. & \frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{w}{\delta} = 0, \quad \frac{y}{\beta} - \frac{z}{\gamma} = 0. \end{array}$$

and also five lines not belonging to the double-sixer, viz.

$$\begin{array}{ll} 12. & x = 0, \quad \left(-\frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \frac{1}{\beta\delta} - k \left(-\frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \frac{1}{\beta'\delta'} = 0, \\ 23. & y = 0, \quad \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} + \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha\gamma} - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha'\gamma'} = 0, \\ 34. & z = 0, \quad \left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \frac{1}{\beta\delta} - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \frac{1}{\beta'\delta'} = 0, \\ 41. & w = 0, \quad \left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha\gamma} - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha'\gamma'} = 0, \\ 56. & \frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta} = 0, \quad \frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'} = 0. \end{array}$$

The remaining lines of the double-sixer are then easily determined; viz. the lines 3, 5, 6, and 12 are met by the line 2', and by a second line 1'; this, as a line meeting 3, 5, 6, will be given by equations of the form

$$x - \frac{\alpha}{\beta}y = \phi \left(\frac{\delta}{\gamma}z - w \right), \quad x - \frac{\alpha'}{\beta'}y = \phi \left(\frac{\delta'}{\gamma'}z - w \right),$$

and observing that these equations, writing therein $x = 0$, give

$$\frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta} = -\frac{\alpha}{\beta\delta\phi}y, \quad \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'} = -\frac{\alpha'}{\beta'\delta'\phi}y,$$

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the condition of intersection with the line 12 gives

$$\phi = \frac{\alpha' - k\alpha}{\delta' - k\delta},$$

which is the value of ϕ in the foregoing equations; and to these we may join the resulting equation

$$y\phi\beta\beta'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta) = z\gamma\gamma'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta).$$

Proceeding in like manner for the lines 3', 2, 4, the equations for the remaining four lines of the double-sixer are

$$\begin{array}{ll} 2. \quad \phi = \frac{\alpha' - k\alpha}{\delta' - k\delta}, & 1'. \quad \phi = \frac{\alpha' - k\alpha}{\gamma' - k\gamma}, \\ y\phi\beta\beta'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta) = z\gamma\gamma'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta), & x\phi\alpha\alpha'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta) = w\delta\delta'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta), \\ y\phi\delta\delta'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta) = w\beta\beta'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta), & x\phi\gamma\gamma'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta) = z\alpha\alpha'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta), \\ 4. \quad \phi = \frac{\beta' - k\beta}{\gamma' - k\gamma}, & 3'. \quad \phi = \frac{\beta' - k\beta}{\delta' - k\delta}, \\ y\phi\beta\beta'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta) = z\gamma\gamma'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta), & x\phi\alpha\alpha'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta) = w\delta\delta'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta), \\ y\phi\alpha\alpha'(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma) = x\gamma\gamma'(\alpha\delta' - \alpha'\delta), & x\phi\delta\delta'(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta) = w\alpha\alpha'(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta). \end{array}$$

It may be added that: in plane $x = 0$,

$$\begin{array}{l} \text{intersection of } 1' \text{ lies on line } z : w = (\gamma\beta' - \alpha'\beta)\gamma\gamma' : \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta, \\ \text{intersection of } 2 \text{ lies on line } y : z = \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta : (\alpha\delta' - \alpha'\delta)\gamma\gamma', \end{array}$$

and that the line joining these intersections is the line 12. In plane $y = 0$,

$$\begin{array}{l} \text{intersection of } 2 \text{ lies on line } x : w = \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta : -(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma)\delta\delta', \\ \text{intersection of } 3' \text{ lies on line } z : w = \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta : (\beta\delta' - \delta\beta')\delta\delta', \end{array}$$

and that the line joining these intersections is the line 23.

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In plane $z = 0$,

$$\begin{array}{l} \text{intersection of } 3' \text{ lies on line } x : y = (\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta)\alpha\alpha' : \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta, \\ \text{intersection of } 4 \text{ lies on line } x : w = -(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma)\alpha\alpha' : \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta, \end{array}$$

and that the line joining these intersections is the line 34. And in plane $w = 0$,

$$\begin{array}{l} \text{intersection of } 4 \text{ is on line } y : z = (\alpha\delta' - \alpha'\delta)\beta\beta' : \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta, \\ \text{intersection of } 1' \text{ is on line } x : y = \alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta : (\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta)\beta\beta', \end{array}$$

and that the line joining these intersections is the line 14.

The equations of the remaining ten lines of the surface may be obtained without difficulty, and also the forty-five triple planes, but I do not stop to effect this; the planes $x = 0$, $y = 0$, $z = 0$, $w = 0$, are, it is clear, triple planes, containing the lines 1, 2', 12; 2', 3, 23; 3, 4', 34; and 4', 1, 41 respectively.

If, to fix the ideas, the planes $x = 0, y = 0, z = 0, w = 0$ are taken to be those of the tetrahedron $ABCD$ ($x = BCD$, &c., as usual), then the edges AB, BC, CD, DA (but not the remaining opposite edges AC, BD) will be lines on the surface. Each plane of the tetrahedron, for instance ABC ($w = 0$), is met by the ten lines not contained therein in two vertices A, C , three points on the edge BA , three points on the edge BC , and two other points, viz. these are the intersections of the plane ABC by the lines 4 and 1'. For the construction of a model it is sufficient to determine the three points on each edge, and the two points, say in the plane ABC and in the plane DBC ($x = 0$) respectively; for then each of the remaining eight lines will be determined as a line joining two points in these two planes respectively. If in the first instance k is considered as a variable parameter, then the two points in the plane $w = 0$ are given as the intersections of two fixed lines by a variable line (14) rotating round the fixed point

$$\frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} = 0, \quad \frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma} = 0;$$

and the like as regards the two points in the plane $x = 0$. By making (with assumed values of the other parameters) the proper drawings for the two planes $w = 0, x = 0$, it is easy to fix upon a convenient value of the parameter k ; and I have in this manner succeeded in making a string model of the double-sixer; viz. the coordinates x, y, z, w are taken to be as the perpendicular distances of the current point from the faces of a regular tetrahedron (the coordinates being positive for an interior point); the values of $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ were put $= 3, 4, 5, 6$ and those of $\alpha', \beta', \gamma', \delta' = 1, 1, 1, 1$; the value of k fixed upon as above was $k = -\frac{1}{2}$; this however brings the lines 2 and 4 too close together, and also their apparent intersection too close to their intersections with the line 6'; and it is probable that a slightly different value of k would be better.

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The results just obtained may be exhibited in a compendious form as follows:

1 is line BC :	$x = 0, z = 0;$	2' is line CD :	$x = 0, y = 0,$
3 is line DA :	$y = 0, z = 0;$	4' is line AB :	$z = 0, w = 0,$
5 meets CD :	$(z : w) = (\gamma : \delta),$	5 meets AB :	$(x : y) = (\alpha : \beta),$
6 meets CD :	$(z : w) = (\gamma' : \delta'),$	6 meets AB :	$(x : y) = (\alpha' : \beta'),$
6' meets BC :	$(y : z) = (\beta : \gamma),$	6' meets AD :	$(x : w) = (\alpha : \delta),$
5' meets BC :	$(y : z) = (\beta' : \gamma'),$	5' meets AD :	$(x : w) = (\alpha' : \delta'),$
1' meets AD :	$x : w = (\alpha' - k\alpha) : (\delta' - k\delta),$	1' meets BCD :	$\frac{-(\alpha' - k\alpha)(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta)\beta\beta'}{(\delta' - k\delta)(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta)\gamma\gamma'},$
1' meets ABC :	$\frac{(\alpha' - k\alpha)(\alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta)}{(\alpha' - k\alpha)(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta)\beta\beta'},$		
3' meets BC :	$y : z = (\beta' - k\beta) : (\gamma' - k\gamma),$	3' meets ACD :	$\frac{-(\beta' - k\beta)(\gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta)\alpha\alpha'}{(\gamma' - k\gamma)(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta)\delta\delta'},$
3' meets ABD :	$\frac{(\beta' - k\beta)(\alpha\gamma\beta'\delta' - \alpha'\gamma'\beta\delta)}{(\gamma' - k\gamma)(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta)\delta\delta'},$		
2 meets AB :	$x : y = (\alpha' - k\alpha) : (\beta' - k\beta),$	2 meets BCD :	$\frac{(\alpha' - k\alpha)(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma)\delta\delta'}{\delta' - k\delta},$
4 meets CD :	$z : w = (\gamma' - k\gamma) : (\delta' - k\delta),$	4 meets ABD :	$\frac{-(\delta' - k\delta)(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma)\alpha\alpha'}{(\gamma' - k\gamma)(\alpha\delta' - \alpha'\delta)\beta\beta'}.$

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The four joining lines obtained from these intersections are

$$\begin{aligned} 1' \text{ and } 2 \text{ meet } BCD \text{ on line } & \left(-\frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \frac{1}{\beta\delta} - k \left(-\frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \frac{1}{\beta'\delta'} = 0, \\ 2 \text{ and } 3' \text{ meet } CDA \text{ on line } & \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} + \frac{z}{\gamma} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha\gamma} - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha'\gamma'} = 0, \\ 3' \text{ and } 4 \text{ meet } DAB \text{ on line } & \left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} - \frac{w}{\delta'}\right) \frac{1}{\beta\delta} - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} - \frac{w}{\delta}\right) \frac{1}{\beta'\delta'} = 0, \\ 4 \text{ and } 1' \text{ meet } ABC \text{ on line } & \left(\frac{x}{\alpha'} - \frac{y}{\beta'} + \frac{z}{\gamma'}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha\gamma} - k \left(\frac{x}{\alpha} - \frac{y}{\beta} + \frac{z}{\gamma}\right) \frac{1}{\alpha'\gamma'} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

For calculating the numerical values from the foregoing assumed data, say

1 : BC ; 2' : CD ; 3 : DA ; 4' : AB ,	
5 meets CD : $z = 45.5, w = 54.5$;	5 meets AB : $x = 42.9, y = 57.1$,
6 meets CD : $z = 50, w = 50$;	6 meets AB : $x = 50, y = 50$,
6' meets BC : $y = 44.4, z = 55.6$;	6' meets AD : $x = 33.3, w = 66.7$,
5' meets BC : $y = 50, z = 50$;	5' meets AD : $x = 50, w = 50$,
1' meets AD : $x = 44, z = 56$;	1' meets BCD : $y = -25.1, z = 39.9, w = 71.8$,
3' meets BC : $y = 48, z = 52$;	3' meets ABD : $x = 47.2, y = 141.7, w = -102.3$,
2 meets AB : $x = 47.8, y = 52.2$;	2 meets BCD : $y = 26.4, z = 44, w = 16.2$,
4 meets CD : $z = 48.1, w = 51.9$;	4 meets ABD : $x = 50.5, y = 187.6, w = -151.5$.

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$$\begin{aligned}
 1' \text{ and } 2 \text{ meet } BCD \text{ on line } & 35y - 32z + 30w = 0, \\
 2 \text{ and } 3' \text{ meet } CDA \text{ on line } & 26x + 22z - 21w = 0, \\
 3' \text{ and } 4 \text{ meet } DAB \text{ on line } & 8x - 7y - 6w = 0, \\
 4' \text{ and } 1 \text{ meet } ABC \text{ on line } & 52x - 47y - 44z = 0,
 \end{aligned}$$

which last four equations serve as a verification.

The outside numerical values are given in the manner most convenient for the construction of a drawing; viz. when the coordinates refer to a point on an edge of the tetrahedron, or say on the side of an equilateral triangle, then taking the length of this edge (or side) to be = 100, the numerical values are fixed so that the sum of the two coordinates may be = 100, and the two coordinates thus denote the distances from the extremities of the edge or side: but when the three coordinates belong to a point in the face of the tetrahedron, or say in the plane of an equilateral triangle, then the sum of the coordinates is made = 86.6, and the three coordinates thus denote the perpendicular distances from the sides of the triangle.

III.

It is possible to find on a cubic curve a double-sixer of points 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6 and 1', 2', 3', 4', 5', 6' such that any six points such as 1, 2, 3, 4', 5', 6' lie in a conic. In fact considering a cubic surface having upon it the double-sixer of lines 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6 and 1', 2', 3', 4', 5', 6', the section by any plane is a cubic curve meeting the lines, say in the points 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6, 1', 2', 3', 4', 5', 6': each of the lines 1, 2, 3 meets each of the lines 4', 5', 6', and consequently the six lines lie in a quadric surface: therefore the points 1, 2, 3, 4', 5', 6' lie in a conic: and so in the other cases; the number of the conics is of course = 60.

The cubic curve may be a given curve, and six of the points upon it (not being points on a conic) may also be taken to be given; for instance the points 1, 2, 3, 1', 4', 5'. For take through the points 2, 3 respectively any two lines 2, 3; through 1', 4', 5' respectively the lines 1', 4', 5' each meeting each of the lines 2, 3; and through 1 a line meeting each of the lines 4', 5'. It is easy to see that a cubic surface may be drawn through the cubic curve and the lines 1, 2, 3, 1', 4', 5'. For the passage through the cubic curve requires 9 conditions; the surface then passes through the point 2 and to make it pass through the line 2 requires 3 conditions; similarly the surface passes through the point 3, and to make it pass through the line 3 requires 3 conditions. The surface now passes through 1' and through the points of intersection of the line 1' with the lines 2, 3: to make it pass through the line 1' requires 1 condition; similarly to make it pass through the lines 4', 5', 1 requires in each case 1 condition; or there are in all 19 conditions, so that the cubic surface is completely determined. Take now through the points 1, 2, 3, 4', 5', a conic meeting the cubic in the point 6': then through the lines 1, 2, 3, 4', 5' we have a quadric surface passing through this

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conic, and therefore through 6': hence through 6' we may draw a line 6' meeting each of the lines 1, 2, 3; and since the cubic surface passes through the point 6' and also through the intersections of the line 6' with the lines 1, 2, 3, it passes through the line 6'. We complete in this manner by constructions in the plane of the cubic the system of the twelve points, viz. each new point is given as the intersection of the cubic curve by a conic drawn through five points of the cubic curve. It is

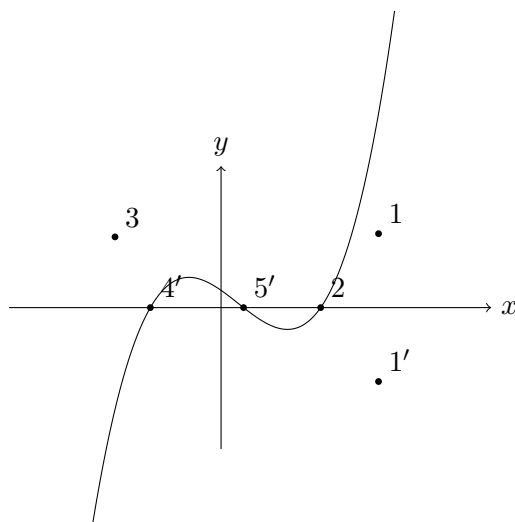
then shown as for the point $6'$ and the line $6'$ through it, that through each new point there can be drawn a line denoted by the same number and meeting each of the lines which it ought to meet, and hence lying on the cubic surface: the twelve points are thus the intersections of the plane of the cubic curve by the twelve lines of the double-sixer; and it follows that the six points which ought to lie in a conic (in every case where such conic has not been used in the plane construction) do actually lie in a conic.

I was anxious to construct such a double-sixer of points on a cubic curve; for this purpose I take the equation of the curve to be

$$y^2 = \left(1 - \frac{x}{a}\right) \left(1 - \frac{x}{b}\right) \left(1 - \frac{x}{c}\right),$$

or say for shortness $y^2 = X$; where, to fix the ideas, a, b are supposed to be positive, a greater than b ; and c to be negative.

The cubic curve is thus a parabola symmetrical in regard to the axis of x , and consisting of a loop and infinite branch; and I take upon it the points $1, 2, 3, 1', 4', 5'$ as shown in the figure,



viz. the coordinates of these points are as stated in the Table, where m is the x coordinate, and

$$\sqrt{M} = \sqrt{\left(1 - \frac{x}{a}\right) \left(1 - \frac{x}{b}\right) \left(1 - \frac{x}{c}\right)}$$

and so in other cases, $\sqrt{14} = 3.74165$.

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point	symbolic		numerical	
	x	y	x	y
1	m	$\sqrt{M}$	6	$\sqrt{14} = 3.742$
2	0	1	0	1
3	0	-1	0	-1
4	θ	$\sqrt{\Theta}$	$2 - \frac{75}{1369} = 1.945$	$-\frac{2280}{373}\sqrt{14} = -.168$
5	ϕ	$\sqrt{\Phi}$	$-1 + \frac{75}{361} = -.792$	$\frac{1110}{193}\sqrt{14} = .606$
6	m_1	$-\sqrt{M_1}$	$\frac{13}{3} = 4.333$	$-\frac{4}{9}\sqrt{14} = -1.641$
1'	m	$-\sqrt{M}$	6	$-\sqrt{14} = -3.742$
2'	σ	$\sqrt{\Sigma}$	$-\frac{1560(14 - \sqrt{14})}{(31\sqrt{14} - 5)^2} = 1.299$	.676
3'	τ	$\sqrt{T}$	$-\frac{1560(14 + \sqrt{14})}{(31\sqrt{14} + 5)^2} = 1.887$	.247
4'	c	0	-1	0
5'	b	0	2	0
6'	m_1	$\sqrt{M_1}$	$\frac{13}{3} = 4.333$	$\frac{4}{9}\sqrt{14} = 1.641$

The numerical values belong to the curve

$$y^2 = \left(1 - \frac{x}{3}\right) \left(1 - \frac{x}{2}\right) (1 + x)$$

and to $m = 6$.

Starting with the points 1, 2, 3, 1', 4', 5' we have to find the remaining points 6', 6, 4, 5, 2', 3'.

Point 6' by means of the conic 1234'5'6', as follows. The equation of the conic is

$$(x - b)(x - c) - bcy^2 + kxy = 0, \quad (2, 3, 4', 5'),$$

and making this pass through the point 1 ($x = m$, $y = \sqrt{M}$) we find

$$(m - b)(m - c) + ka\sqrt{M} = 0. \quad (1)$$

Hence taking the coordinates of 6' to be $m_1, \sqrt{M_1}$, we have

$$(m_1 - b)(m_1 - c) + ka\sqrt{M_1} = 0, \quad (6')$$

and thence

$$\frac{\sqrt{M_1}}{\sqrt{M}} = \frac{(m_1 - b)(m_1 - c)}{(m - b)(m - c)} = \frac{M_1(m - a)}{M(m_1 - a)}.$$

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that is,

$$\frac{\sqrt{M_1}}{\sqrt{M}} = \frac{(m_1 - b)(m_1 - c)}{(m - b)(m - c)} = \frac{m_1 - a}{m - a}.$$

We have thus for m_1 a quadric equation satisfied by $m = m_1$, so that throwing out the factor $m - m_1$, the equation is a linear one, viz. we find

$$m_1 = \frac{ma - ab - ac + bc}{m - a},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$m_1 - a = \frac{(a - b)(a - c)}{m - a},$$

and thence also

$$\sqrt{M_1} = \frac{(a-b)(a-c)}{(m-a)^2} \sqrt{M},$$

viz. $\sqrt{M_1}$ is determined rationally in terms of $m, \sqrt{M}$; this is of course as it should be, since the point $6'$ is uniquely determinate.

Point 6 by means of the conic 2361'4'5'. In precisely the same manner the coordinates are $m_1, -\sqrt{M_1}$, where $m_1, \sqrt{M_1}$ denote the same quantities as before.

Point 4 by means of the conic 2341'5'6'. The equation of the conic is

$$Fx + Gy + H = \frac{1-y^2}{x}, \quad (2, 3),$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} Fb + H &= \frac{1}{b}, & (5'), \\ Fm_1 + G\sqrt{M_1} + H &= \frac{1-M_1}{m_1}, & (6'), \\ Fm - G\sqrt{M} + H &= \frac{1-M}{m}, & (1'), \end{aligned}$$

which give without difficulty

$$abcF = -a - c + P, \quad \sqrt{M} abcG = (m-b)(-m+P), \quad abcH = ab + ac + bc - bP,$$

where

$$P = 2a - c - \frac{2(a-c)(b-c)}{m+m_1-2c},$$

a quantity which will presently be expressed in terms of m only. And then

$$F\theta + G\sqrt{\Theta} + H = \frac{1-\Theta}{\theta},$$

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or say

$$F(\theta - b) + G\sqrt{\Theta} = \frac{1-\Theta}{\theta} - \frac{1}{b} = -(\theta - b) \left(\frac{1}{ab} + \frac{1}{bc} - \frac{\theta}{abc} \right),$$

that is,

$$(\theta - b)(abcF + a + c - \theta) + Gab\sqrt{\Theta} = 0,$$

viz. that is,

$$(\theta - b)(P - \theta) + (m - b) \frac{\sqrt{\Theta}}{\sqrt{M}} (P - m) = 0.$$

or, rationalising and throwing out the factor $\theta - b$, this is

$$(\theta - b)(\theta - P)^2 - (m - b)(m - P)^2 \frac{(\theta - a)(\theta - b)}{(m - a)(m - b)} = 0,$$

which is a cubic equation satisfied by $\theta = m$ and $\theta = m_1$; so that throwing out the factors $\theta - m, \theta - m_1$ we have for θ a linear equation.

Putting for shortness

$$A = (m - a)^2 - (a - b)(a - c), \quad B = (m - b)^2 - (b - c)(b - a), \quad C = (m - c)^2 - (c - a)(c - b),$$

the value of θ may be expressed in the forms

$$\theta - a = \frac{B^2}{C^2}(c - a), \quad \theta - b = \frac{A^2}{C^2}(c - b), \quad \theta - c = \frac{4(m - a)(m - b)(m - c)(b - c)(a - c)}{C^2}.$$

We have moreover

$$P - c = \frac{2(a - c)(m - b)(m - c)}{C}, \quad P - m = -\frac{(m - c)A}{C},$$

equations which express P in terms of m only; also

$$\theta - P = -\frac{2(a - c)(m - b)(m - c)B}{C^2},$$

and then

$$\sqrt{\Theta} = -\sqrt{M} \frac{\theta - b}{m - b} \frac{P - \theta}{P - m},$$

whence

$$\sqrt{\Theta} = 2\sqrt{M} (b - c)(c - a) \frac{AB}{C^3},$$

so that $\theta, \sqrt{\Theta}$ are now determined.

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Point 5 by means of the conic 2351'4'6'. The conic is

$$Fx + Gy + H = \frac{1 - y^2}{x}, \quad (2, 3),$$

where

$$\begin{aligned} Fc + H &= \frac{1}{c}, & (4'), \\ Fm_1 + G\sqrt{M_1} + H &= \frac{1 - M_1}{m_1}, & (6'), \\ Fm - G\sqrt{M} + H &= \frac{1 - M}{m}, & (1'). \end{aligned}$$

Everything is the same as for the point 4 except that b, c are interchanged; hence writing Q instead of P , and using A, B, C to denote as before, we have

$$abcF = -a - b + Q, \quad \sqrt{M} abcG = (m - c)(-m + Q), \quad abcH = ab + ac + bc - cQ,$$

and

$$\begin{aligned} \phi - a &= \frac{C^2(b - a)}{B^2}, & \phi - b &= \frac{4(m - a)(m - b)(m - c)(c - b)(a - b)}{B^2}, & \phi - c &= \frac{A^2(b - c)}{B^2}, \\ Q - b &= \frac{2(m - b)(m - c)(a - b)}{B}, & Q - m &= -\frac{A(m - b)}{B}, & \phi - Q &= -\frac{2(m - b)(m - c)C(a - b)}{B^2}, \end{aligned}$$

and

$$\sqrt{\Phi} = 2\sqrt{M} (c - b)(b - a) \frac{AC}{B^3},$$

which determine $\phi, \sqrt{\Phi}$.

Point 3' by means of the conic 1263'4'5'. The conic is

$$Fx + Gy + H = \frac{(x - b)(x - c)}{y}, \quad (4', 5'),$$

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and we have

$$G + H = bc, \quad (2)$$

$$Fm + G\sqrt{M} + H = \frac{(m - b)(m - c)}{\sqrt{M}}, \quad (1)$$

$$Fm_1 - G\sqrt{M_1} + H = \frac{(m_1 - b)(m_1 - c)}{-\sqrt{M_1}}, \quad (6)$$

Eliminating F , we have

$$G(m_1\sqrt{M} + m\sqrt{M_1}) + H(m - m_1) = \frac{m_1(m - b)(m - c)}{\sqrt{M}} \frac{m(m_1 - b)(m_1 - c)}{\sqrt{M_1}},$$

which is easily reduced first to

$$G \frac{2mm_1 - a(m + m_1)}{(m - a)\sqrt{M}} H(m - m_1) = (m + m_1) \frac{(m - a)(m - b)}{\sqrt{M}},$$

and then to

$$G\{aA + 2m(a - b)(a - c)\} - H \frac{(m - a)A}{\sqrt{M}} abc\{-A + 2m(m - a)\} = 0;$$

and combining herewith $G + H = bc$, we have

$$H = \frac{2bcm\{a(m - a) + (a - b)(a - c)\}}{aA + 2m(a - b)(a - c) + \frac{(m - a)A}{\sqrt{M}}},$$

$$G = bc - H;$$

and we have then

$$F(m + m_1) + G(\sqrt{M} - \sqrt{M_1}) + 2H = 0,$$

that is,

$$F\{2m(m - a) - A\} + G \frac{A\sqrt{M}}{m - a} + 2H(m - a) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$F\{2m(m - a) - A\} = -bc \frac{A\sqrt{M}}{m - a} - H \left\{ 2(m - a) - \frac{A\sqrt{M}}{m - a} \right\}.$$

We then have

$$Fx + H = y \left(-G + \frac{(x - b)(x - c)}{y^2} \right) = y \left(-G - \frac{abc}{x - a} \right) = -\frac{y(Ha + Gx)}{x - a},$$

that is,

$$(Fx + H)^2 = -\frac{(x - b)(x - c)}{abc(x - a)} (Ha + Gx)^2.$$

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or

$$abc(x - a)(Fx + H)^2 + (x - b)(x - c)(Gx + Ha)^2 = 0.$$

Developing and throwing out the factor x , this is

$$\begin{aligned} & G^2x^3 + \{2aGH - (b + c)G^2 + abcF^2\}x^2 \\ & + \{a^2H^2 - 2a(b + c)GH + bcG^2 + abc(2FH - aF^2)\}x \\ & + \{-(b + c)a^2H^2 + 2abcGH + abc(H^2 - 2aFH)\} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

This must be satisfied by $x = m$, $x = m_1$; hence the left hand must be $G^2(x - m)(x - m_1)(x - \sigma)$, or equating the constant terms we have

$$G^2mm_1\sigma = aH\{-2abcF + 2bcG + (bc - ab - ac)H\},$$

which gives σ ; and we then have

$$\sqrt{\Sigma} = -\frac{\sigma - a}{G\sigma + Ha}(F\sigma + H),$$

but I have not attempted the further reduction of these expressions.

The numerical values for the example are

$$3F = \frac{-140 + 62\sqrt{14}}{5 + 21\sqrt{14}}, \quad G = \frac{-10 + 62\sqrt{14}}{5 + 21\sqrt{14}}, \quad H = \frac{-104\sqrt{14}}{5 + \sqrt{14}},$$

whence σ as in the Table.

Point $2'$ by means of the conic $1362'4'5'$. The equation of the conic is

$$Fx + Gy + H = \frac{(x - b)(x - c)}{y}, \quad (4', 5'),$$

where

$$-G + H = -bc, \tag{3}$$

$$Fm + G\sqrt{M} + H = \frac{(m - b)(m - c)}{\sqrt{M}}, \tag{1}$$

$$Fm_1 - G\sqrt{M_1} + H = \frac{(m_1 - b)(m_1 - c)}{-\sqrt{M_1}}, \tag{6}$$

which are the same as for point $3'$, if only we reverse the signs of F, H and $\sqrt{M}, \sqrt{M_1}$.

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Hence the formulae are

$$H = -\frac{2bcm\{a(m - a) + (a - b)(a - c)\}}{aA + 2m(a - b)(a - c) - \frac{(m - a)A}{\sqrt{M}}},$$

$$G = bc + H,$$

$$F\{2m(m - a) - A\} = -bc\frac{A\sqrt{M}}{m - a} - H\left\{2(m - a) + \frac{A\sqrt{M}}{m - a}\right\},$$

$$G^2mm_1\tau = aH\{-2abcF - 2bcG + (bc - ab - ac)H\},$$

which gives τ ; and then

$$\sqrt{T} = \frac{\tau - a}{G\tau - Ha}(F\tau + H),$$

which are also unreduced.

The numerical values are

$$3F = \frac{140 + 62\sqrt{14}}{5 - 21\sqrt{14}}, \quad G = \frac{-10 - 62\sqrt{14}}{5 - 21\sqrt{14}}, \quad H = \frac{-104\sqrt{14}}{5 - 21\sqrt{14}},$$

whence τ as in the Table.

[Printed p. 385; source PDF p. 449.]

522. NOTE ON THE THEORY OF INVARIANTS.

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. III. (1871), pp. 268–271.]

If two binary quantics $(a, \dots)(x, y)^n$, $(a', \dots)(x', y')^n$ are linearly transformable the one into the other, and if for the first of them P, Q are any two invariants whatever of the same degree, and P', Q' are the like invariants for the second of them, then we have

$$P : Q = P' : Q',$$

(or, what is the same thing, the absolute invariants have the same values for the two functions respectively); and the entire system of these equations constitutes only a $(n - 3)$ fold relation between the two sets of coefficients. But the converse theorem, viz. that if the entire system of equations is satisfied, the two functions are linearly transformable the one into the other, is only true *sub modo*.

For instance, considering the two binary sextics

$$(0, 0, 0, d, e, f, g)(x, y)^6 \quad \text{and} \quad (0, 0, 0, d', e', f', g')(x', y')^6,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(20d, 5e, 2f, g)(x, y)^3y^3 \quad \text{and} \quad (20d', 5e', 2f', g')(x', y')^3y'^3,$$

the invariants of the two functions respectively are each and all of them = 0, and yet the two functions are not in general linearly transformable the one into the other.

For they can be transformable only by the substitution

$$x = \lambda x' + \mu y', \quad y = \rho y';$$

or, what is the same thing, only if the cubic functions are transformable by the substitution $x = x' + ay'$, $y = y'$; and forming for these the seminvariants $ac - b^2$ and $a^2d - 3abc + 2b^3$ for the cubic $(a, b, c, d)(x, y)^3$, we have as the necessary condition for the transformability

$$(8df - 5e^2)^3 : (8d^2g - 12def + 5e^3)^2 = (8d'f' - 5e'^2)^3 : (8d'^2g' - 12d'e'f' + 5e'^3)^2.$$

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To deduce this result from the theory of the sextic function, I observe that denoting by A, B, C, Δ , the values of the quadrinvariant, the sextinvariant, and the discriminant, as given in Salmon's *Higher Algebra*, Ed. 2, pp. 202–211, then in the particular case $a = 0, b = 0$, we have

$$\begin{array}{llll} A = & -10d^2 & B = & d^4 \\ & +15ce & & -3cd^2e \\ & & & +c^2e^2 \\ C = & -8d^6 & \Delta = & 0, \\ & +36cd^4e & & -39c^2d^2e^2 \\ & & & -8c^3e^3. \end{array}$$

and hence forming the new invariants

$$B = 100B - A^2, \quad \Gamma = 1000C - 1200AB + 4A^3,$$

the values of these in the same particular case $a = b = 0$ are

$$B = 25c^2(8df - 5e^2) - 100c^3g,$$

$$\Gamma = -2500c^3(8d^2g - 12def + 5e^3) + 3000c^4(10eg - 9f^2).$$

Taking now A, B, C, Δ as the invariants of the sextic, one of the conditions for the transformation is $B^3 : C^2 = B'^3 : C'^2$.

In the particular case $a = b = c = 0$ and $a' = b' = c' = 0$, the invariants vanish and the equation is satisfied identically. But if we assume in the first instance only $a = b = 0$, $a' = b' = 0$, then the

terms contain the common factors c^6 and c'^6 respectively; and throwing these out, and then writing $c = 0, c' = 0$, we obtain the condition previously found in a different manner.

It will be observed that the condition is of the original form $P : Q = P' : Q'$, but with the difference that P, Q and the corresponding functions P', Q' , are not invariants. As possessing the foregoing property these functions may however be called “imperfect invariants,” it being understood that an imperfect invariant is not an invariant, and is not in any case included in the term “invariant” used without qualification.

And we may now establish the general theory as follows: Consider the similarly constituted special forms $(a, \dots)(x, y, z, \dots)^n$ and $(a', \dots)(x', y', z', \dots)^n$: to fix the ideas the coefficients $(a, \dots)$ may be regarded as homogeneous functions of the elements $(\alpha, \beta, \dots)$ which are either independent, or homogeneously connected together in any manner; and then the coefficients $(a', \dots)$ will be the like functions of the elements $(\alpha', \beta', \dots)$ which are either independent or (as the case may be) homogeneously connected in the like manner.

The entire series of functions $P, Q, \dots$ of $(\alpha, \beta, \dots)$, which are such that P, Q being of the same degree, and P', Q' being the like functions of $(\alpha', \beta', \dots)$, we have for the linearly transformable functions $(a, \dots)(x, y, z, \dots)^n$ and $(a', \dots)(x', y', z', \dots)^n$ the relation

$$P : Q = P' : Q',$$

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may be called the “perfect and imperfect invariants” of $(a, \dots)(x, y, z, \dots)^n$; and the relation in question be briefly referred to by the expression that the perfect and imperfect invariants are proportional.

We have then the theorem that if the two functions $(a, \dots)(x, y, z, \dots)^n$ and $(a', \dots)(x', y', z', \dots)^n$ are linearly transformable the one into the other, the two functions have their perfect and imperfect invariants proportional; and *conversely* the theorem, that two functions which have their perfect and imperfect invariants proportional, are linearly transformable the one into the other.

There is thus a wide field of inquiry in regard to the imperfect invariants, even of a binary function, but still more so as to those of a ternary or quaternary function representing a curve or surface possessed of singularities.

We have in what precedes the explanation of an error into which I fell in my paper “On the transformation of plane curves,” *Proc. Lond. Math. Soc.*, vol. I. No. 3, Oct. 1865, [384], see Arts. Nos. 27–30. Considering a given curve of deficiency D and, by means of a system of $D - 3$ points chosen at pleasure on the curve, transforming this into a curve of the order $D + 1$ with deficiency D ; then for any two of the transformed curves (that is, two curves obtained by means of different systems of the $D - 3$ points) I showed that these had the same absolute invariants—or in the language of the present paper, that they had their invariants proportional, and I thence inferred that the two transformed curves were linearly transformable the one into the other—whereas, to sustain this conclusion, it is necessary that the two curves should have their perfect and imperfect invariants proportional; and this was in no wise proved. That the two transformed curves are not in fact linearly transformable the one into the other has since been shown *a posteriori* by Dr Brill in the particular case $D = 4$. Riemann’s conclusions, with which my own were at variance, are thus correct.

I remark that if a binary function of an odd or even degree $n = 2p + 1$ or $= 2p$, has $p + 1$ equal factors, then the invariants all of them vanish; but the equality of the $p + 1$ factors implies only a p -fold relation between the coefficients; that is, the vanishing of all the invariants gives only a p -fold relation between the coefficients, viz. the relation is $\frac{1}{2}(n - 1)$ fold or $\frac{1}{2}n$ -fold according as n is odd or even. Thus for a sextic function the equations $A = 0, B = 0, C = 0, \Delta = 0$ constitute only a 3-fold relation between the coefficients.

Similarly if the function has p equal factors, then every invariant is a mere numerical multiple of a power of one and the same function Θ ; so that the vanishing invariants can be at once formed.

And we have thus only a $(p - 1)$ fold relation between the coefficients, viz. the relation is $\frac{1}{2}(n - 3)$ fold or $\frac{1}{2}(n - 2)$ fold according as n is odd or even.

Cambridge, 4 August, 1870.

[Printed p. 388; source PDF p. 452.]

523. ON THE TRANSFORMATION OF UNICURSAL SURFACES.

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. III. (1871), pp. 469–474.]

I consider the question of the transformation (*Abbildung auf einer Ebene*) of unicursal surfaces. Taking (x, y, z, w) for the coordinates of a point on the surface, (x', y', z') for those of the corresponding point on the plane; then if X', Y', Z', W' denote each of them a function $(x', y', z')^{n'}$, the equations of transformation are

$$x : y : z : w = X' : Y' : Z' : W' :$$

and assuming that each of the curves

$$X' = 0, \quad Y' = 0, \quad Z' = 0, \quad W' = 0$$

(or, what is the same thing, the general curve

$$aX' + bY' + cZ' + dW' = 0)$$

passes once through each of α_1 points, twice through each of α_2 points, $\dots$, r times through each of α_r points (for convenience I write α_r instead of α'_r); and writing also

$$n = n'^2 - \sum r^2 \alpha_r,$$

$$0 = \frac{1}{2}n'(n' + 3) - 3 - \Theta - \frac{1}{2} \sum r(r + 1) \alpha_r,$$

(where Θ is = 0 or positive except in the case of special relations between the positions of the fixed points $\alpha_1, \alpha_2, \dots, \alpha_r$), which equations give

$$-n = 3n' - 6 - 2\Theta - \sum r \alpha_r;$$

then the order of the surface is $= n$, and the order of the nodal curve is

$$b = \frac{1}{2}(n - 2)(n - 3) + \Theta.$$

I assume that the nodal curve has h apparent double points and t actual triple points, but no stationary points, so that q being the class, we have

$$q = b^2 - b - 2h - 6t;$$

and I endeavour to find these numbers q, t, h .

[Printed p. 389; source PDF p. 453.]

For this purpose, imagine through the nodal curve a surface of the order k , which therefore meets the surface besides in a curve of the order $nk - 2b$; this curve I call the k -thic residue of the nodal curve, or simply the “residue.” The projection (*Abbildung*) of the complete intersection kn is a curve of the order kn' passing kr times through each of the points α_r : this is made up of the projection of the nodal curve once, and of the projection of the residue. But as shown by Dr Clebsch

the projection of the nodal curve is of the order $(n-4)n' + 3$, and it passes $(n-4)r + 1$ times through each of the points α_r ; hence the projection of the residue is of the order $(k-n+4)n' - 3$, and it passes $(k-n+4)r - 1$ times through each of the points α_r . I assume that the projection of the residue is the general curve which satisfies the foregoing conditions, viz. that the residue, and its projection as defined by the foregoing conditions, depend each of them on the same number of constants. The necessity for this I confess by no means obvious: but take as an illustration Steiner's quartic surface as transformed by the equations

$$x : y : z : w = x'^2 : y'^2 : z'^2 : (x' + y' + z')^2 :$$

the nodal curve consists of three lines meeting in a point, the quadric residue is the remaining intersection of the surface by a quadric cone passing through the three lines; and the projection thereof is a line; the quadric cone, and therefore the conic, each depend upon 2 constants; and the line which is the projection of the conic depends upon the same number (2) of constants: at all events I make the assumption provisionally.

Now in the projection of the residue, we have twice the number of constants

$$= [(k-n+4)n' - 3](k-n+4)n' - 2 \sum [(k-n+4)r - 1](k-n+4)r \alpha_r,$$

viz. this is

$$= (k-n+4)^2 (n'^2 - \sum r^2 \alpha_r) + (k-n+4) (-3n' + 2 \sum r \alpha_r),$$

or, what is the same thing, it is

$$= (k-n+4)^2 n + (k-n+4)(n-6-2\Theta),$$

viz. reducing, and replacing Θ by its value $-\frac{1}{2}(n-2)(n-3) + b$, the number in question is

$$= k^2 n + k(-n^2 + 4n - 2b) + 2(n-4)b.$$

Now k being $=$ or $> n-3$, the curve of intersection of a given surface n by a surface k depends on

$$\frac{1}{6}(k+1)(k+2)(k+3) - \frac{1}{6}(k-n+1)(k-n+2)(k-n+3) - 1$$

constants; and making the surface k to pass through the curve b we have to subtract herefrom $(k+1)b - \frac{1}{2}q - 2t$; that is, for the residue, twice the number of constants is

$$\begin{aligned} &= \frac{1}{3}(k+1)(k+2)(k+3) - \frac{1}{3}(k-n+1)(k-n+2)(k-n+3) \\ &\quad - 2 - 2(k+1)b + q + 4t, \end{aligned}$$

viz. this is

$$= k^2 n + k(-n^2 + 4n - 2b) + \frac{1}{3}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - 2b + q + 4t.$$

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Hence comparing the two expressions in question we have

$$2(n-4)b = \frac{1}{3}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - 2b + q + 4t,$$

that is,

$$0 = \frac{1}{3}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - 2(n-3)b + q + 4t,$$

or, as I prefer to write it,

$$q + 4t = 2(n-3)b - \frac{1}{3}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3),$$

which agrees with a more general formula in my “Memoir on the theory of Reciprocal Surfaces,” *Phil. Trans.* vol. CLIX. (1869), [411], see p. 227, [Coll. Math. Papers, vol. VI. p. 356]. I consider any two residues, a k -thic residue and a l -thic residue; to each intersection of these there corresponds an intersection of their projections: or the number of intersections of the two residues must be equal to that of the two projections. Now the projections being (as above)

$$\begin{aligned} &\text{order } (k - n + 4)n' - 3 \text{ passing } (k - n + 4)r - 1 \text{ times through each point } \alpha_r, \\ &\text{order } (l - n + 4)n' - 3 \text{ passing } (l - n + 4)r - 1 \text{ times through each point } \alpha_r, \end{aligned}$$

the number of the intersections in question is

$$\begin{aligned} &= [(k - n + 4)n' - 3][(l - n + 4)n' - 3] \\ &\quad - \sum [(k - n + 4)r - 1][(l - n + 4)r - 1]\alpha_r + \omega, \end{aligned}$$

where for a reason which will be afterwards explained I have added the term ω : this is

$$\begin{aligned} &= (k - n + 4)(l - n + 4) \left(n'^2 - \sum r^2 \alpha_r \right) \\ &\quad + (k + l - 2n + 8) \left(-3n' + \sum r \alpha_r \right) + 9 - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right), \end{aligned}$$

viz. it is

$$= (k - n + 4)(l - n + 4)n + (k + l - 2n + 8)(n - 6 - 2\Theta) + 9 - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right),$$

viz. substituting for Θ its value $-\frac{1}{2}(n - 2)(n - 3) + b$, and reducing, the number is

$$= kln - 2(k + l)b - n^3 + 8n^2 - 16n + 9 + 4(n - 4)b - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right).$$

But the surfaces n, k, l , having in common the curve b which is a nodal curve on n , besides intersect in

$$kln - b(n + 2k + 2l - 4) + 2q + 9t$$

points (Salmon’s *Geometry of Three Dimensions*, 2nd Ed. p. 283, except that in the formula as there given the singularity t is not taken account of); that is, the number of intersections of the two residues is

$$kln - b(n + 2k + 2l - 4) + 2q + 9t,$$

which is equal to the number of intersections of the two projections; or comparing the numbers in question we have

$$-n^3 + 8n^2 - 16n + 9 + 4(n - 4)b - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right) = -(n - 4)b + 2q + 9t,$$

that is,

$$2q + 9t = 5(n - 4)b - n^3 + 8n^2 - 16n + 9 - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right).$$

Two $(n + \lambda)$ -thic residues meet in $n(\lambda + 4)(\lambda + 6) - 12\lambda - 39 - 4(\lambda + 4)\Theta - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right)$ points; in particular, two $(n - 3)$ -thic residues meet in $3n - 3 - 4\Theta - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right)$ points; and two $(n - 2)$ -thic residues meet in $8n - 15 - 8\Theta - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right)$ points.

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But we have already found

$$2q + 8t = 4(n - 3)b - \frac{1}{2}n^3 + 4n^2 - \frac{25}{2}n + 4,$$

and we have therefore

$$t = (n - 8)b - \frac{1}{2}n^3 + 4n^2 - \frac{7}{2}n + 5 - \left(\sum \alpha_r - \omega \right),$$

and

$$q = -2(n-13)b + n^3 - 14n^2 + 31n - 18 + 4(\sum \alpha_r - \omega).$$

I obtain these results in a different manner by investigating expressions for the deficiency (*Geschlecht*) of the nodal residue $nk - 2b$ and for that of its projection.

First for the projection, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Twice Deficiency} &= [(k-n+4)n' - 4][(k-n+4)n' - 5] \\ &\quad - \sum [(k-n+4)r - 1][(k-n+4)r - 2]\alpha_r + 2\omega, \end{aligned}$$

where I have added the term 2ω , as afterwards explained: this is

$$= (k-n+4)^2 \left(n'^2 - \sum r^2 \alpha_r \right) + (k-n+4) \left(-9n' + 3 \sum r \alpha_r \right) + 20 - 2(\sum \alpha_r - \omega),$$

viz. it is

$$= (k-n+4)^2 n + (k-n+4)(3n - 18 - 6\Theta) + 20 - 2(\sum \alpha_r - \omega),$$

or substituting for Θ its value $-\frac{1}{2}(n-2)(n-3) + b$ and reducing, it is

$$= k^2 n + k(n^2 - 4n - 6b) - 2n^3 + 16n^2 - 32n + 20 + 6(n-4)b - 2(\sum \alpha_r - \omega).$$

Next as regards the residue, the number h' of its apparent double points is obtained in terms of h and t by the formula

$$8h + 6t - 2h' = (kn - 4b)(k-1)(n-1) - 2b(k-1),$$

(Salmon, l.c., p. 284, except that the singularity t is not there taken account of); and we thence have

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Twice Deficiency} &= (kn-1)(kn-2) - 2h' \\ &= kn(k+n-4) + 4b^2 + b(-4n-6k+12) + 2 - 8h - 6t, \end{aligned}$$

or introducing q instead of h by the formula $4b^2 - 8h = 4q + 4b + 24t$, this is

$$= kn(k+n-4) + b(-4n-6k+12) + 4q + 4b + 2 + 18t,$$

viz. it is

$$= k^2 n + k(n^2 - 4n - 6b) - 4(n-4)b + 4q + 18t.$$

So that comparing with the deficiency of the projection we have

$$-2n^3 + 16n^2 - 32n + 20 + 6(n-4)b - 2(\sum \alpha_r - \omega) = -4(n-4)b + 4q + 2 + 18t,$$

that is,

$$2q + 9t = 5(n-4)b - n^3 + 8n^2 - 16n + 9 - (\sum \alpha_r - \omega),$$

the same result as before.

[523] ON THE TRANSFORMATION OF UNICURSAL SURFACES

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The necessity for the term ω appears by the consideration that if we apply to the plane figure a Cremona-transformation, thus obtaining a new transformation of the surface, the value of Σa_r will in general be altered; whereas the expressions for q, t should it is clear remain unaltered; and it arises as follows, viz. for certain transformations of the surface the curve of the order $(k - n + 4)n' - 3$, passing $(k - n + 4)r - 1$ times through each point a_r and assumed to be the projection of the residue, is not an indecomposable curve but contains a certain number ω of factors (each belonging to a unicursal curve definable by means of the number of its passages through the several points a_r), which factors are to be rejected in order to obtain the equation of the proper residue. Thus reverting to the transformation

$$x : y : z : w = x'^2 : y'^2 : z'^2 : (x' + y' + z')^2$$

of Steiner's surface, the projection of the quadric residue was (as already remarked) a line; applying to the plane figure the ordinary quadric (or inverse) transformation we introduce three fixed points, ($a_2 = 3$), say these are A, B, C ; viz. in the new transformation of the surface the projection of any plane section is a quartic curve having a node at each of the fixed points: the projection of the residue ought clearly to be a conic through the three points; but according to the general formula it is a quintic having at each of these points a triple point: the quintic is in fact made up of the lines BC, CA, AB and of the conic which is the proper residue; viz. in the case in question there are 3 factors thrown out, or we have $\omega = 3$. To apply this to the second investigation of $2q + 9t$, by comparison of the two deficiencies, observe that in general if a curve is made up of $\omega + 1$ indecomposable curves, the deficiency of the compound curve is equal to the sum of the deficiencies of the component curves $-\omega$; hence if ω of the curves are unicursal, the deficiency of the compound curve is equal to that of the remaining curve $-\omega$; or, what is the same thing, the deficiency of the remaining curve is equal to that of the compound curve $+\omega$; and the addition of the term $+\omega$ to the expression for the deficiency is thus accounted for. It is easy to see that a like explanation applies to the first investigation of $2q + 9t$.

I further remark, reverting to the equations

$$x : y : z : w = X' : Y' : Z' : W'$$

of the transformation, that the product of the ω factors is given as the common factor (if any) of the Jacobians

$$J(Y', Z', W'), \quad J(Z', W', X'), \quad J(W', X', Y') \quad \text{and} \quad J(X', Y', Z').$$

Such common factor exists whenever we can by a Cremona-transformation of the plane figure reduce the number of the points a_r upon which the transformation of the surface depends; viz. for any given transformation of the surface, ω is equal to the excess of Σa_r above the minimum value of Σa_r , or, what is the same thing, $\Sigma a_r - \omega$ is equal to the minimum value of Σa_r , and is thus independent of the particular transformation. And of course if Σa_r has this minimum value, viz. if the transformation is such that the number of the points a_r cannot be reduced by any Cremona-transformation of the plane figure, then we have $\omega = 0$.

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I presume that for the most simple transformation, that is, when n' has its least value, Σa_r has also its least value, and consequently that ω is $= 0$.

Recapitulating, the results obtained are

$$\begin{aligned} q &= -2(n - 13)b + n^3 - 14n^2 + 31n - 18 + 4(\Sigma a_r - \omega), \\ t &= (n - 8)b - \frac{1}{3}n^3 + 4n^2 - \frac{26}{3}n + 5 - (\Sigma a_r - \omega), \end{aligned}$$

where it will be recollected that

$$b = \frac{1}{2}(n-2)(n-3) + \Theta;$$

the formulae are verified in the several cases:

n'	a_1	a'_2	n	Θ	ω	b	q	t	
2	2	0	2	0	1	0	0	0	Quadric surface
2	1	0	3	1	0	1	0	0	Cubic scroll
2	0	0	4	2	0	3	0	1	Steiner's quartic surface
3	6	0	3	0	0	0	0	0	Cubic surface
3	5	0	4	1	0	2	2	0	Quartic with nodal conic
2	8	1	4	0	0	1	0	0	Do. with nodal line
2	7	1	5	-1	0	4	8	0	Quintic with nodal quadriquadric
2	11	0	5	0	0	3	4	0	Do. with nodal skew cubic
2	12	2	5	-1	0	2	0	0	Do. with two non-intersecting nodal lines

which are the transformations chiefly as yet examined: but the first-mentioned case (quadric surface, generalised stereographic projection), although as stated the formulae are verified with the value $\omega = 1$, does not really come under the foregoing theory. It is interesting to see that they are verified in the last-mentioned case, belonging to a negative value of Θ , that is, to a special system of fixed points.

Cambridge, Dec. 5, 1870.

[524] ON THE DEFICIENCY OF CERTAIN SURFACES

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. III. (1871), pp. 526–529.]

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If a given point or curve is to be an ordinary or singular point or curve on a surface of the order n , this imposes on the surface a certain number of conditions, which number may be termed the “Postulation”; thus “Postulation of a given curve *qua* i -tuple curve on a surface n ” will denote the number of conditions to be satisfied by the surface in order that the given curve may be an i -tuple curve on the surface.

The “deficiency” (Flächengeschlecht) of a given surface of the order n is

$$= \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3)$$

less deficiency-value of the several singularities; viz. as shown by Dr Noether, if the surface has a given i -tuple curve, the deficiency-value hereof is

$$= \text{Postulation of the curve } qua \text{ } (i-1) \text{ tuple curve on a surface } n-4;$$

and if the surface has an i -conical point, the deficiency-value hereof is

$$= \text{Postulation of the point } qua \text{ } (i-2) \text{ conical point on a surface } n-4;$$

viz. this is $= \frac{1}{6}i(i-1)(i-2)$, and is thus independent of the order of the surface.

I remark that if the tangent-cone at the i -conical point has δ double lines and κ cuspidal lines, then the deficiency-value is

$$= \frac{1}{6}i(i-1)(i-2) + (i-2)(n-i-1)(\delta + \kappa).$$

In the case of a double or cuspidal curve $i = 2$, and the deficiency-value is

$$= \text{Postulation of given curve } qua \text{ simple curve on a surface } n-4;$$

and so for an ordinary conical point $i = 2$, and the deficiency-value is $= 0$: results which were first obtained by Dr Clebsch.

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I found in this manner the expression for the deficiency of a surface n having a double and cuspidal curve and the other singularities considered in my “Memoir on the Theory of Reciprocal Surfaces,” *Phil. Trans.* vol. CLIX. (1869), [411, *Coll. Math. Papers*, vol. VI. p. 356]; viz. this was

$$D = \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - (n-3)(b+c) + \frac{1}{2}(q+r) + 2t + \frac{7}{2}\beta + \frac{3}{2}\gamma + i - \frac{1}{8}\theta,$$

where we have

- b , order of double curve,
- q , class of Do.,
- c , order of cuspidal curve,
- r , class of Do.,
- β , number of intersections of the two curves, stationary points on b ,
- γ , number of intersections, stationary points on c ,
- i , number of intersections, not stationary points on either curve,
- θ , number of certain singular points on c , the nature of which I do not completely understand; it is here taken to be $= 0$.

Before going further I remark that

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Postulation of right line } qua \text{ } i\text{-tuple on surface } n &= \frac{1}{2}i(i+1)n - \frac{1}{6}i(i+1)(2i-5) \\ &= \frac{1}{6}i(i+1)(3n-2i+5). \end{aligned}$$

Whence if a surface n has an i -tuple right line, the deficiency-value hereof is

$$= \frac{1}{6}i(i-1)(3n-2i-5),$$

or we have

$$\begin{aligned} D &= \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - \frac{1}{6}i(i-1)(3n-2i-5) \\ &= \frac{1}{6}(i-n+1)(i-n+2)(2i+n-3); \end{aligned}$$

so that $D = 0$ if either $i = n-1$ or $i = n-2$; the former case is that of a scroll (skew surface) with an $(n-1)$ tuple right line, the latter that of a surface with an $(n-2)$ tuple line: whence (as shown by Dr Noether) such surface is rationally transformable into a plane.

For a surface of the order n with an i -conical point where the tangent cone has δ double lines and κ cuspidal lines, we have

$$\begin{aligned} D &= \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) \\ &\quad - \left\{ \frac{1}{6}i(i-1)(i-2) + (i-2)(n-i-1)(\delta + \kappa) \right\} \\ &= \frac{1}{6}(n-i-1)\{n^2 + n(i-5) + i^2 - 4i + 6 - 6(i-2)(\delta + \kappa)\}; \end{aligned}$$

viz. for $i = n-1$ this is $D = 0$ (in fact, a surface n with an $(n-1)$ conical point is at once seen to be rationally transformable into a plane): and for $i = n$, that is, for a cone of the order n , we have

$$D = -\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2) + (n-2)(\delta + \kappa) - (n-3)(\delta + \kappa),$$

where the last term $-(n-3)(\delta + \kappa)$ is added because in the present case the surface has the δ double lines and the κ cuspidal lines.

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The formula therefore gives

$$D = -\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2) + \delta + \kappa;$$

viz. this is equal to the deficiency of the plane sections taken negatively.

I find that the same property exists first in the case of a scroll (skew surface) having only a double curve; and secondly in the case of a torse (developable surface) having a cuspidal curve with the ordinary singularities; and this being so there can I think be no doubt but that it is true for any scroll or torse whatever—viz. that for any ruled surface whatever the deficiency is equal to that of the plane section taken negatively.

First, for the scroll, we have

$$D = \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - (n-3)b + \frac{1}{2}q + 2t,$$

which should be

$$= -\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2) + h.$$

Salmon's equations give in the case of a scroll

$$3t = (n-4)\{3b - n(n-2)\}, \quad q = n(n-2)(n-5) - 2(n-6)b,$$

and with these values the relation is at once verified.

Secondly, for the torse; changing the notation into that used for the singularities of the curve and torse, we have

$$D = \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - (n-3)x + \frac{1}{2}q + 2t + \frac{7}{2}\beta + \frac{3}{2}\gamma + i,$$

which should be

$$= -\frac{1}{2}(m-1)(m-2) + h + \beta.$$

We have $q = r(n-3) - 3x$, and substituting this value and expressing everything in terms of r, m, n by means of the formulae

$$\begin{aligned} x &= \frac{1}{2}(r^2 - r - n - 3m), & a &= \frac{1}{2}n - 3r + 3m, \\ \beta &= n - 3r + 3m, \\ t &= \frac{1}{2}\{r^3 - 3r^2 - 58r - 3r(n+3m) + 42n + 78m\}, \\ \gamma &= rm + 12r - 14m - 6n, \end{aligned}$$

we have after all reductions

$$D = -\frac{1}{2}(m+n) + r - 1 = -\frac{1}{2}(m-1)(m-2) + h + \beta.$$

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We have thus a class of surfaces of negative deficiency; viz. any rational transformation of a cone for which the plane section has a given (positive) deficiency produces such a surface: and I think it may be assumed conversely that a surface of negative deficiency is always the rational transformation of a cone for which the deficiency is equal to that of the surface taken with the reverse sign. As an instance, take a quintic surface having a nodal conic and two 3-conical (cubiconical) points (this of course implies that the line joining the two cubiconical points is a line on the surface); the formula for the deficiency is ($n = 5, b = 2, q = 2, r = 0, t = 0$)

$$D = \frac{1}{6}(n-1)(n-2)(n-3) - (n-3)b + \frac{1}{2}q + 2t - 2,$$

(viz. a term -1 for each of the cubiconical points)

$$= 4 - 4 + 1 - 2, \quad = -1.$$

Such a surface can be obtained as the quadric inverse of a cubic cone; viz. taking for the vertex the point $x : y : z : w = \alpha : \beta : \gamma : \delta$ and the cone to pass through the point $x = 0, y = 0, z = 0$, the equation of the cone is

$$(\delta x - \alpha w, \delta y - \beta w, \delta z - \gamma w)^3 = 0,$$

where

$$(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^3 = 0.$$

Taking Q a quadric function $(x, y, z)^2$, the transformation in question consists in the change of x, y, z, w into xw, yw, zw, Q ; viz. the new equation, rejecting the factor w which divides out, is

$$w^{-1}(\delta xw - \alpha Q, \delta yw - \beta Q, \delta zw - \gamma Q)^3 = 0,$$

which is a quintic surface, having the two cubiconical points $x = 0, y = 0, z = 0$ and

$$x : y : z : w = \alpha : \beta : \gamma : \delta^{-1}Q_0$$

(where Q_0 is the value of Q on writing therein α, β, γ in place of x, y, z): and having the nodal conic $w = 0, Q = 0$.

Cambridge, 5 Jan. 1871.

[525] AN EXAMPLE OF THE HIGHER TRANSFORMATION OF A BINARY FORM

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. IV. (1871), pp. 359–361.]

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The quartic

$$(1) \quad (a, b, c, d, e)(x, y)^4$$

is by means of the two quadrics

$$(2) \quad (\alpha, \beta, \gamma)(x, y)^2 \quad \text{and} \quad (\alpha', \beta', \gamma')(x, y)^2$$

transformed into

$$(3) \quad (a_1, b_1, c_1, d_1, e_1)(x_1, y_1)^4,$$

that is, eliminating x, y from

$$(a, b, c, d, e)(x, y)^4 = 0, \quad (\alpha x_1 + \alpha' y_1, \beta x_1 + \beta' y_1, \gamma x_1 + \gamma' y_1)(x, y)^2 = 0,$$

we obtain

$$(a_1, b_1, c_1, d_1, e_1)(x_1, y_1)^4 = 0.$$

It is required to express the invariants of (3) in terms of the simultaneous invariants of (1) and (2).

Write

$$P, Q, R = \alpha x_1 + \alpha' y_1, \quad \beta x_1 + \beta' y_1, \quad \gamma x_1 + \gamma' y_1;$$

the equations from which (x, y) have to be eliminated are

$$(a, b, c, d, e)(x, y)^4 = 0, \quad (P, Q, R)(x, y)^2 = 0.$$

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and the result of the elimination therefore is

$$\begin{vmatrix} a & 4b & 6c & 4d & e \\ & a & 4b & 6c & 4d & e \\ & & P & 2Q & R \\ & & P & 2Q & R \\ P & 2Q & R & & \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

viz. this determinant is the transformed quartic $(a_1, b_1, c_1, d_1, e_1)(x_1, y_1)^4$.

The developed expression of the determinant is

$$\begin{aligned} & a^2 R^4 - 8abQR^3 + \left(\begin{matrix} -12ac \\ +16b^2 \end{matrix} \right) PR^3 - 24acQ^2R^2 + \left(\begin{matrix} 24ad \\ -48bc \end{matrix} \right) PQR^2 - 32adQ^3R \\ & + \left(\begin{matrix} 2ae \\ -32bd \\ +36c^2 \end{matrix} \right) P^2R^2 + \left(\begin{matrix} -16ae \\ +64bd \end{matrix} \right) PQ^2R + 16aeQ^4 \\ & + \left(\begin{matrix} 24be \\ -48cd \end{matrix} \right) P^2QR - 32bePQ^3 + \left(\begin{matrix} -12ce \\ +16d^2 \end{matrix} \right) P^3R + 24ceP^2Q^2 \\ & - 8deP^3Q + e^2P^4. \end{aligned}$$

So that writing for P, Q, R their values, we have the transformed function $(a_1, b_1, c_1, d_1, e_1)(x_1, y_1)^4$, the coefficients being of the forms

$$\begin{aligned} a_1 &= (a, b, c, d, e)^2(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^4, \\ b_1 &= (\alpha\beta)^2(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^3(\alpha', \beta', \gamma'), \\ &\dots \\ e_1 &= (\alpha\gamma)^2(\alpha', \beta', \gamma')^4. \end{aligned}$$

Writing I, J for the invariants of the quartic (1), and

$$\begin{aligned} A &= 4(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta)(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma) - (\gamma\alpha' - \gamma'\alpha)^2, \\ B &= (e, c, a, b, c, d)(\alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta, \gamma\alpha' - \gamma'\alpha, \beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma)^2, \end{aligned}$$

we have I, J, A, B simultaneous invariants of the forms (1) and (2). Putting moreover $\nabla = I^3 - 27J^2$, and writing I_1, J_1, ∇_1 for the like invariants of the form (3), I find

$$\begin{aligned} I_1 &= 4 \left(4IB^2 + 12JAB + \frac{1}{3}I^2A^2 \right), \\ J_1 &= 8 \left\{ 8JB^3 + \frac{1}{3}I^2AB^2 + 2IJA^2B + \left(2J^2 - \frac{1}{27}I^3 \right) A^3 \right\}, \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$\nabla_1 = 256(4B^3 - IA^2B - JA^3)\nabla.$$

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As a verification, suppose $(a, b, c, d, e)(x, y)^4 = x^4 + y^4$ (whence $I = 1, J = 0$). And take

$$x_1(x + y)^2 - y_1(x - y)^2 = 0$$

for the transforming equation, that is, $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma) = (1, 1, 1)$ and $(\alpha', \beta', \gamma') = (-1, 1, -1)$. We have $P = R = x_1 - y_1$ and $Q = x_1 + y_1$, and thence

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Det} &= (P^2 + R^2)^2 - 16PQ^2R + 16Q^4 \\ &= (2P^2 - 4Q^2)^2 = (-2x_1^2 - 12x_1y_1 - 2y_1^2)^2, \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$(a_1, b_1, c_1, d_1, e_1)(x_1, y_1)^4 = 4(x_1^2 + 6x_1y_1 + y_1^2)^2,$$

whence

$$I_1 = \frac{4096}{3} = \frac{2^{12}}{3}, \quad J_1 = -\frac{262144}{27} = -\frac{2^{18}}{27};$$

also

$$A = -16, \quad B = 8,$$

and the equations for I_1, J_1 become

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{4096}{3} &= 4 \left(4 \cdot 64 + \frac{1}{3}256 \right), \\ -\frac{262144}{27} &= 8 \left(\frac{4}{3} \cdot (-16) \cdot 64 + \frac{1}{27}4096 \right), \end{aligned}$$

which are true. More generally, assuming

$$(a, b, c, d, e)(x, y)^4 = x^4 + 6\Theta x^2y^2 + y^4,$$

(whence $I = 1 + 3\Theta^2$, $J = \Theta - \Theta^3$), and the same transforming equation, we have

$$(a_1, b_1, c_1, d_1, e_1)(x_1, y_1)^4 = 4\{(1 + 3\Theta)x_1^2 + (3 - 3\Theta)2x_1y_1 + (1 + 3\Theta)y_1^2\}^2,$$

whence

$$I_1 = \frac{2^{12}}{3}(1 - 3\Theta)^2, \quad J_1 = -\frac{2^{18}}{27}(1 - 3\Theta)^3;$$

also

$$A = -16, \quad B = 8(1 - \Theta).$$

Substituting these different values in the equations for I_1, J_1 , we obtain

$$16(1 - 3\Theta)^2 = 12(1 + 3\Theta^2)(1 - \Theta)^2 - 72(\Theta - \Theta^3)(1 - \Theta) + 4(1 + 3\Theta^2)^2,$$

and

$$\begin{aligned} -8(1 - 3\Theta)^3 &= 27(\Theta - \Theta^3)(1 - \Theta)^3 - 9(1 + 3\Theta^2)^2(1 - \Theta)^2 \\ &\quad + 27(1 + 3\Theta^2)(\Theta - \Theta^3)(1 - \Theta) - 54(\Theta - \Theta^3)^2 + (1 + 3\Theta^2)^3, \end{aligned}$$

which are in fact satisfied identically.

Cambridge, 26 July, 1871.

[526] ON A SURFACE OF THE EIGHTH ORDER

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. IV. (1871), pp. 558–560.]

p. 401 [526; source PDF p. 465]

I reproduce in an altered form, so as to exhibit the application thereto of the theory of the six coordinates of a line, the analysis by which Dr Hierholzer obtained the equation of the surface of the eighth order, the locus of the vertex of a quadricone which touches six given lines.

I call to mind that if $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$, $(\alpha', \beta', \gamma', \delta')$ are the coordinates of any two points on a line, then the quantities (a, b, c, f, g, h) , which denote respectively

$$(\beta\gamma' - \beta'\gamma, \gamma\alpha' - \gamma'\alpha, \alpha\beta' - \alpha'\beta, \alpha\delta' - \alpha'\delta, \beta\delta' - \beta'\delta, \gamma\delta' - \gamma'\delta),$$

and which are such that $af + bg + ch = 0$, are the six coordinates of the line.¹

Consider the given point (x, y, z, w) and the given line (a, b, c, f, g, h) , and write for shortness

$$P = hy - gz + aw, \quad Q = -hx + fz + bw, \quad R = gx - fy + cw, \quad S = -ax - by - cz;$$

then taking (X, Y, Z, W) as current coordinates, the equation of the plane through the given point and line is

$$PX + QY + RZ + SW = 0.$$

Considering in like manner the given point (x, y, z, w) and the three given lines $(a_1, b_1, c_1, f_1, g_1, h_1)$, $(a_2, \dots)$, $(a_3, \dots)$, then we have the three planes

$$P_i X + Q_i Y + R_i Z + S_i W = 0, \quad i = 1, 2, 3,$$

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and if these planes have a common line, the point (x, y, z, w) is in a line meeting each of the three given lines; that is, the locus of the point is the hyperboloid through the three given lines. It follows that the equations

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_1 & Q_1 & R_1 & S_1 \\ P_2 & Q_2 & R_2 & S_2 \\ P_3 & Q_3 & R_3 & S_3 \end{vmatrix} = 0$$

reduce themselves to a single equation, that of the hyperboloid in question.

I write for shortness

$$\begin{aligned} (000) &= (agh)x^2 + (bhf)y^2 + (cfg)z^2 + (abc)w^2 \\ &\quad + [(abg) - (cah)]xw + [(bch) - (abf)]yw + [(caf) - (bcg)]zw \\ &\quad + [(bfg) + (chf)]yz + [(cgh) + (afg)]zx + [(ahf) + (bgh)]xy, \end{aligned}$$

viz. (123) will mean $(a_1 g_2 h_3)x^2 + \dots$, where $(a_1 g_2 h_3)$ etc. denote as usual the determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} a_1 & g_1 & h_1 \\ a_2 & g_2 & h_2 \\ a_3 & g_3 & h_3 \end{vmatrix}, \quad \text{etc.}$$

Then the equations in question are found to be

$$x(123) = 0, \quad y(123) = 0, \quad z(123) = 0, \quad w(123) = 0,$$

¹Cayley, "On the six coordinates of a line," *Camb. Phil. Trans.* vol. XI. (1869), [435], pp. 290–323.

reducing themselves to the single equation $(123) = 0$, which is accordingly that of the hyperboloid through the three lines.²

Proceeding now to the above-mentioned problem, we have the point (x, y, z, w) , and the six lines $(a_1, b_1, c_1, f_1, g_1, h_1)$, $(a_2, \dots)$ etc., say the lines 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6: the six planes

$$P_1X + Q_1Y + R_1Z + S_1W = 0, \quad \text{etc.}$$

must be tangents to the same quadricone; that is, considering the sections by the plane $W = 0$, the six lines

$$P_1X + Q_1Y + R_1Z = 0, \quad \text{etc.}$$

must be tangents to the same conic, and the condition for this is

$$[123456] = 0,$$

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where the symbol stands for the determinant

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_1^2 & Q_1^2 & R_1^2 & Q_1R_1 & R_1P_1 & P_1Q_1 \\ P_2^2 & \dots & & & & \\ \vdots & & & & & \end{vmatrix}.$$

But as is well known this equation may be written

$$(*) \quad (126)(346)(145)(235) - (146)(236)(125)(345) = 0,$$

where (126) etc. denote the determinants

$$\begin{vmatrix} P_1 & Q_1 & R_1 \\ P_2 & Q_2 & R_2 \\ P_6 & Q_6 & R_6 \end{vmatrix}, \quad \text{etc.};$$

or, what is the same thing, they denote the functions above represented by the like symbols $(126) = (a_1g_2h_6)x^2 + \dots$. The equation $(*)$ just obtained is Hierholzer's equation for the surface of the eighth order, the locus of the vertex of a quadricone which touches six given lines.

I remark that in my "Memoir on Quartic Surfaces," *Proc. Lond. Math. Soc.* vol. III. (1870), [445], pp. 19–69, I obtained the equation of the surface under the foregoing form $[123456] = 0$ or say $[(P, Q, R)^2] = 0$, noticing that there was a factor w^4 , so that the order of the surface is $= 8$; and further that the equation might be written

$$w^8 \exp \frac{1}{w} \{x(g\partial_c - h\partial_b) + y(h\partial_a - f\partial_c) + z(f\partial_b - g\partial_a)\} [(a, b, c)^2] = 0,$$

where $\exp \Theta$ (read exponential) denotes e^Θ , and $[(a, b, c)^2]$ denotes

$$\begin{vmatrix} a_1^2 & b_1^2 & c_1^2 & b_1c_1 & c_1a_1 & a_1b_1 \\ a_2^2 & \dots & & & & \\ \vdots & & & & & \end{vmatrix}.$$

Also that the equation contains the four terms

$$x^8[(a, -h, g)^2] + y^8[(h, b, -f)^2] + z^8[(-g, f, c)^2] + w^8[(a, b, c)^2] = 0.$$

Cambridge, 12 September, 1871.

²This equation is given in the paper above referred to, §54.

[527] ON A THEOREM IN COVARIANTS

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. V. (1872), pp. 625–629.]

p. 404 [527; source PDF p. 468]

The proof given in Clebsch, *Theorie der binären algebraischen Formen* (Leipzig, 1872), of the finite number of the covariants of a binary form depends upon a subsidiary proposition which is deserving of attention for its own sake.

I use my own hyperdeterminant notation, which is as follows. Considering a function $U = (a, \dots)(x, y)^n$ (viz. $U_1 = (a, \dots)(x_1, y_1)^n$, &c.), and writing $12 = d_{x_1}d_{y_2} - d_{y_1}d_{x_2}$, &c., then the general form of a covariant of the degree m is

$$k(12^\alpha 23^\beta \dots)U_1U_2 \dots U_m,$$

where k is a merely numerical factor, the indices $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \dots$ are positive integers, and after the differentiations each set of variables $(x_1, y_1), \dots, (x_m, y_m)$ is replaced by (x, y) . I say that the general form of a covariant is as above; viz. a covariant is equal to a single term of the above form, or a sum of such terms.

Attending to a single term: the sum of the indices of all the duads which contain a particular number $1, 2, \dots$ as the case may be is called an index-sum; each index-sum is at most $= n$; so that, calling the index-sums $\sigma_1, \sigma_2, \dots, \sigma_m$ respectively, we have $n - \sigma_1, n - \sigma_2, \dots, n - \sigma_m$ each of them zero or positive. The term, before the several sets of variables are each replaced by (x, y) , is of the orders $n - \sigma_1, n - \sigma_2, \dots, n - \sigma_m$ in the several sets of variables respectively.

The term may be expressed somewhat differently: for writing

$$V_1 = xd_{x_1} + yd_{y_1}, \quad V_2 = xd_{x_2} + yd_{y_2}, \quad \&c.,$$

then (except as to a numerical factor) it is for a function $\phi(x_1, y_1)$ the same thing whether we change (x_1, y_1) into (x, y) , or operate on this function with V_1^p , and so for the other sets; the term may therefore be written

$$V_1^{n-\sigma_1}V_2^{n-\sigma_2} \dots (12^\alpha 23^\beta \dots)U_1U_2 \dots U_m,$$

being now in the first instance a function of the single set (x, y) of variables.

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We may omit the operand $U_1U_2 \dots U_m$, and consider only the symbol

$$k(12^\alpha 13^\beta 23^\gamma \dots) \quad \text{or} \quad V_1^{n-\sigma_1} \dots V_m^{n-\sigma_m}(12^\alpha 13^\beta 23^\gamma \dots),$$

which, under either of the two forms, I represent for shortness by $[12 \dots m]$. Observe that this is considered as a symbol involving the m symbolic numbers $1, 2, 3, \dots, m$, even although in particular cases one or more of these numbers may be wanting from the actual expression of the symbol: thus $[123]$ may denote 12^n , but the operand to be supplied thereto is always $U_1U_2U_3$.

A sum of symbols is not in general equal to a single symbol; but a single symbol can be expressed in a variety of ways as a sum of symbols: the most simple transformation-formulae relate to three or four symbolic numbers; viz. for three such numbers, say $1, 2, 3$, we have

$$V_1.23 + V_2.31 + V_3.12 = 0,$$

showing that in a symbol, which written with the V 's involves $V_1.23$, this may be replaced by its value $V_2.13 - V_3.12$; and so in other cases.

For the four numbers 1, 2, 3, 4 we have a group of the like formulae

$$\begin{array}{rrrr} -V_{2.34} & +V_{3.24} & -V_{4.23} & = 0, \\ V_{1.34} & & -V_{3.14} & -V_{4.31} = 0, \\ -V_{1.24} & & +V_{3.14} & -V_{4.12} = 0, \\ V_{1.23} & +V_{2.31} & & = 0, \end{array}$$

leading to

$$23.14 + 31.24 + 12.34 = 0,$$

which is a form not involving the V 's and consequently is applicable to the transformation of invariant-symbols where the numbers

$$n - \sigma_1, n - \sigma_2, \dots, n - \sigma_m$$

are all = 0.

I establish the following definitions. A symbol $[12 \dots m]$ is proximate when each index-sum is $< n$; otherwise it is ultimate; viz. this is the case when any one or more of the index-sums is or are $= n$. We may say that the symbol is ultimate as to 1 if $\sigma_1 = n$; and that it is ultimate as to 1, 2 if σ_1 and σ_2 are each $= n$: and so in other cases.

A proximate symbol which has any one index-sum thereof $< \frac{1}{2}n$ is said to be inferior: thus if $\sigma_1 < \frac{1}{2}n$ the symbol is inferior in regard to 1; and so if σ_1 and σ_2 are each $< \frac{1}{2}n$, it is inferior in regard to 1 and 2: and the like in other cases.

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Observe that if a symbol is inferior then in the covariant the order exceeds the degree by a number which is greater than $\frac{1}{2}n - 1$: in fact, suppose it inferior in regard to 1, then the order is

$$(n - \sigma_1) + (n - \sigma_2) + \dots + (n - \sigma_m),$$

where each term after the first is at least = 1, that is, the order is at least $= n - \sigma_1 + m - 1$; hence order minus degree is at least $= n - \sigma_1 - 1$; viz. σ_1 being less than $\frac{1}{2}n$, this is greater than $\frac{1}{2}n - 1$. Conversely, if for any symbol order-degree is $> \frac{1}{2}n - 1$, then the symbol is not inferior.

A symbol $[12 \dots m]$ is sharp when any index is $> \frac{1}{2}n$; otherwise it is flat; viz. this is so when each index is $< \frac{1}{2}n$. The symbol is sharp as to any particular duad or duads when the index or indices thereof is or are each of them $> \frac{1}{2}n$.

The subsidiary theorem is now as follows: "A symbol is inferior or sharp: or it can be expressed as a sum of symbols each of which is inferior or sharp"—or what is the same thing, the only symbols which need to be considered are those which are either inferior or sharp.

Thus for the degree 1 the symbol is $[1]$ (which is simply unity), $\sigma_1 = 0$, and the symbol is inferior. For the degree 2 the symbol is $[2] = 12^k$; if $k < \frac{1}{2}n$ the symbol is inferior, if $k > \frac{1}{2}n$ then it is sharp.

A proof is first required for the degree 3; here

$$[123] = 12^\alpha 13^\beta 23^\gamma$$

($\beta + \gamma, \gamma + \alpha, \alpha + \beta$ each = or $< n$), which may very well be neither inferior nor sharp; for instance, if $n = 5$, we have $12^2 13^2 23^2$, where each index being = 2, the symbol is not sharp; and each index-sum being = 4, the symbol is not inferior. But writing the symbol in the form

$$V_1 V_2 V_3 12^2 13^2 23^2,$$

then by means of the relation

$$V_{1.23} + V_{2.31} + V_{3.12} = 0$$

(or, what is the same thing, $V_1.23 = V_2.13 - V_3.12$), the symbol becomes

$$\begin{aligned} & V_1 V_2 V_3 12^2 13^2 23^2 (V_2.13 - V_3.12), \\ & = V_2^2 V_3 12^2 13^3 23^2 - V_2 V_3^2 12^3 13^2 23^2, \end{aligned}$$

where each term, as containing an index 3, is sharp. To complete the reduction, observe that calling the expression $21 - 33$, then in the term 31 interchanging the numbers 2 and 3 we obtain $31 = -23$, and thence $21 - 23 = 221$; so that the whole is $2V_2^2 V_3 12^2 13^3 23^2$, viz. it is a multiple of a sharp term.

I prove the general case, substantially in the manner used by Dr Clebsch, as follows. We assume that the theorem is proved up to a particular degree m : that is, we assume that every symbol belonging to a degree not exceeding m can be

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expressed as a sum of terms each of which is sharp or inferior: and we have to prove this for the next following degree $m + 1$, or writing for convenience p in place of $m + 1$ (say for the degree p); that is, for a symbol

$$[12 \dots mp] = p1^{\lambda_1} p2^{\lambda_2} \dots pm^{\lambda_m} [12 \dots m] = P[12 \dots m], \quad \text{suppose.}$$

I write as before $\sigma_1, \sigma_2, \dots, \sigma_m$ for the index-sums of $[12 \dots m]$: those of $[12 \dots mp]$ are therefore $\sigma_1 + \lambda_1, \sigma_2 + \lambda_2, \dots, \sigma_m + \lambda_m$, and (for the duads involving p) $\sigma_p = \lambda_1 + \lambda_2 + \dots + \lambda_m$.

If $[12 \dots m]$ is sharp, then $[12 \dots mp]$ is sharp, and the theorem is true. If $\sigma_p < \frac{1}{2}n$, then $[12 \dots mp]$ is inferior in regard to p ; and the theorem is true. The only case requiring a proof is when $[12 \dots m]$ is not sharp (being therefore inferior) and when $\sigma_p > \frac{1}{2}n$. And in this case if any one of the indices $\lambda_1, \dots, \lambda_m$ is $> \frac{1}{2}n$ (or say if P is sharp) then the theorem is true.

Consider the expression

$$p1^{\lambda_1} p2^{\lambda_2} \dots pm^{\lambda_m} [12 \dots m],$$

where $\sigma_1, \sigma_2, \dots, \sigma_m$ are as before the index-sums for $[12 \dots m]$ and therefore the numbers

$$n - \sigma_1 - \lambda_1, \dots, n - \sigma_m - \lambda_m$$

are none of them negative.

Assume that when $[12 \dots m]$ is inferior, and when $\lambda_1, \dots, \lambda_m$ have any values such that their sum is not greater than a given value $\sigma_p - 1$, the expression is a sum of terms each of which is inferior or sharp: we wish to show that when $\lambda_1 + \lambda_2 + \dots + \lambda_m$ has the next succeeding value, $= \sigma_p$, the case is still the same.

For this purpose, introducing the V 's I write

$$Q = V_1^{n-\sigma_1-\lambda_1} \dots V_m^{n-\sigma_m-\lambda_m} V_p^{n-\sigma_p} p1^{\lambda_1} p2^{\lambda_2} \dots pm^{\lambda_m} [12 \dots m].$$

Then supposing for a moment that λ_1 is not $= n - \sigma_1$ and λ_2 is not $= 0$, the expression contains the factor $V_1.p2$, which is equal to and may be replaced by $-V_2.p1 + V_p.12$: we have thus, omitting the V 's,

$$\begin{aligned} Q &= p1^{\lambda_1+1} p2^{\lambda_2-1} p3^{\lambda_3} \dots pm^{\lambda_m} [12 \dots m], \\ Q' &= p1^{\lambda_1} p2^{\lambda_2-1} p3^{\lambda_3} \dots pm^{\lambda_m} 12[12 \dots m]. \end{aligned}$$

Now for Q' the sum of the indices $\lambda_1, \lambda_2 - 1, \lambda_3, \dots, \lambda_m$ is $\sigma_p - 1$, so that by hypothesis Q' is inferior or sharp: that is, the difference $Q - Q'$ is inferior or sharp; so that to prove that Q is inferior or sharp, we have only to prove this of Q , where this new Q is derived from the old one by increasing by unity the index of $p1$, at the expense of that of $p2$

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which is diminished by unity. Such change is possible so long as the index λ_1 has not attained its maximum value, $n - \sigma_1$ or σ_p as the case may be, and there is any other index $\lambda_2, \dots, \lambda_m$ which is not $= 0$: that is, we may pass from Q to Q' , from Q' to Q'' and so on; and it will be sufficient to show that the last term of the series is inferior or sharp. We thus pass from Q to R , where

$$R = p1^{n-\sigma_1}p2^{\lambda_2-\alpha_2} \dots pm^{\lambda_m-\alpha_m}[12 \dots m]$$

and $\alpha_2 + \alpha_3 + \dots + \alpha_m = n - \sigma_1 - \lambda_1$; or else to

$$R = p1^{\sigma_p}[12 \dots m],$$

according as $n - \sigma_1$ is not greater or is greater than σ_p .

Now let $[12 \dots m]$ be inferior; suppose it to be so in regard to 1, that is, let σ_1 be less than $\frac{1}{2}n$ or $n - \sigma_1$ greater than $\frac{1}{2}n$. Then if σ_p be less than $\frac{1}{2}n$ it is less than $n - \sigma_1$, that is, we have for R the last-mentioned form which is inferior in regard to p , viz. R is inferior; if σ_p is equal to or greater than $\frac{1}{2}n$, then R , whichever its form may be, is sharp as to $p1$, viz. R is sharp. Hence in either case Q is a sum of terms which are inferior or sharp; that is, assuming the theorem for a form for which $\lambda_1 + \lambda_2 + \dots + \lambda_m$ does not exceed a given value $\sigma_p - 1$, the theorem is true for the next succeeding value σ_p ; or being true for the case $\sigma_p - 1 = 0$, it is true generally.

Cambridge, 24 April, 1872.

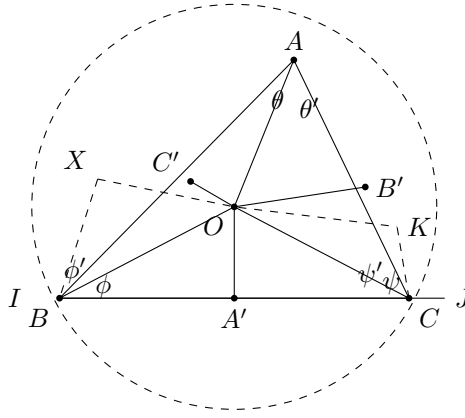
[528] ON THE NON-EUCLIDIAN GEOMETRY

[From the *Mathematische Annalen*, vol. V. (1872), pp. 630–634.]

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The theory of the Non-Euclidian Geometry as developed in Dr Klein's paper "Ueber die Nicht-Euklidische Geometrie" may be illustrated by showing how in such a system we actually measure a distance and an angle and by establishing the trigonometry of such a system. I confine myself to the "hyperbolic" case of plane geometry; viz. the absolute is here a real conic, which for simplicity I take to be a circle; and I attend to the points *within* the circle.

I use the simple letters $a, A, \dots$ to denote (linear or angular) distances measured in the ordinary manner; and the same letters, with a superscript stroke, $\bar{a}, \bar{A}, \dots$, to denote the same distances measured according to the theory.



The radius of the absolute is for convenience taken to be $= 1$; the distance of any point from the centre can therefore be represented as the sine of an angle.

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The distance BC , or say $\bar{a}$, of any two points B, C is by definition as follows:

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Radius of circle} &= 1, \\ \text{in } \triangle ABC, \text{ sides are} & a, b, c, \\ \text{angles} & A, B, C, \\ OA, OB, OC &= \sin p, \sin q, \sin r, \\ OA', OB', OC' &= \sin a, \sin b, \sin c, \\ \angle BOC, \angle COA, \angle AOB &= \alpha, \beta, \gamma. \end{aligned}$$

Where I, J are the intersections of the line BC with the circle,

$$e^{\bar{a}} + e^{-\bar{a}}, \quad \text{or} \quad 2 \cosh \bar{a} = \frac{BI.CJ}{BJ.CI} + \frac{BJ.CI}{BI.CJ} = \frac{BI.CJ + BJ.CI}{\sqrt{BI.BJ.CI.CJ}}.$$

The numerator is

$$BI(BJ - BC) + CI(BC + CJ) = BI.BJ + CI.CJ + BC(CI - BI) = BI.BJ + CI.CJ + BC^2.$$

Hence taking a for the distance BC , and $\sin q, \sin r$ for the distances OB, OC respectively, we have $BI.BJ = \cos^2 q$, $CI.CJ = \cos^2 r$; and the formula is

$$\cosh \bar{a} = \frac{\cos^2 q + \cos^2 r + a^2}{2 \cos q \cos r}.$$

Or, what is the same thing, taking α for the angle BOC , and therefore

$$a^2 = \sin^2 q + \sin^2 r - 2 \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha,$$

we have

$$\cosh \bar{a} = \frac{1 - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha}{\cos q \cos r}.$$

In a similar manner, if $\sin a$ is the perpendicular distance from O on the line BC (that is, $a \sin a = \sin q \sin r \sin \alpha$), it can be shown that

$$\sinh \bar{a} = \frac{a \cos a}{\cos q \cos r},$$

the equivalence of the two formulae appearing from the identity

$$\cos^2 q \cos^2 r = (1 - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha)^2 - a^2 + a^2 \sin^2 a,$$

which is at once verified.

Next for an angle; we have by definition

$$\bar{A} = \frac{1}{2i} \log \frac{\sin BAI \cdot \sin CAJ}{\sin BAJ \cdot \sin CAI}.$$

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Where AI, AJ are the (imaginary) tangents from A to the circle; or writing for shortness BI &c. instead of BAI &c. (the angular point being always at A),

$$\bar{A} = \frac{1}{2i} \log \frac{\sin BI \sin CJ}{\sin BJ \sin CI}.$$

Consequently

$$e^{i\bar{A}} - e^{-i\bar{A}} = 2i \sin \bar{A} = \frac{\sin BI \sin CJ - \sin BJ \sin CI}{\sqrt{\sin BI \sin CJ} \sqrt{\sin BJ \sin CI}},$$

where the numerator is

$$\sin BI \sin(CJ - BC) - \sin CJ \sin(BI + BC) = \sin BC \sin IJ,$$

or say $= \sin A \sin IJ$. Moreover taking the distance OA to be $= \sin p$, and the perpendicular distances from O on the lines AB, AC to be $\sin c$ and $\sin b$ respectively, then if for a moment the angle IJ is put $= 2\omega$, we have $\sin p \sin \omega = 1$; moreover

$$\sin BI \sin BJ = \sin(\omega - BO) \sin(\omega + BO) = \sin^2 \omega - \sin^2 BO,$$

and $\sin p \sin BO = \sin c$; that is,

$$\sin BI \sin BJ = \frac{\cos^2 c}{\sin^2 p}, \quad \sin CI \sin CJ = \frac{\cos^2 b}{\sin^2 p}.$$

Also

$$\sin IJ = -\sin 2\omega = 2 \sin \omega \cos \omega = \frac{2 \cos p}{\sin^2 p}.$$

Whence the required formula

$$\sin \bar{A} = \frac{\cos p \sin A}{\cos b \cos c}.$$

In the same way, or analytically from this value, we have

$$\cos \bar{A} = \frac{\cos A + \sin b \sin c}{\cos b \cos c},$$

and thence also

$$\tan \bar{A} = \frac{\cos p \sin A}{\cos A + \sin b \sin c}.$$

In particular, taking the line AC to pass through O , or writing in the formula $b = 0$, we have

$$BO = \tan^{-1}(\cos p \tan \theta), \quad CO = \tan^{-1}(\cos p \tan \theta');$$

we ought to have

$$A = BO + CO = \tan^{-1}(\cos p \tan \theta) + \tan^{-1}(\cos p \tan \theta'),$$

which, observing that $\sin p \sin \theta = \sin c$ and $\sin p \sin \theta' = \sin b$, also $A = \theta + \theta'$, is in fact equivalent to the above formula for $\tan \bar{A}$. Observe in particular that when A is at the centre, $p = 0$, and the formula becomes $\bar{A} = \theta + \theta' = A$, or say for an angle at the centre, $\bar{A} = A$.

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I return to the expression for $\cosh \bar{a}$; in explanation of its meaning, let the distances OB, OC be q, r respectively and let the angle BOC be α ; to find $\bar{q}$ we have only to take C at O , that is, in the formula for $\cosh \bar{a}$ to write $r = 0$, we thus find

$$\cosh \bar{q} = \frac{1}{\cos q}, \quad \cosh \bar{r} = \frac{1}{\cos r},$$

whence also

$$\cos q = \operatorname{sech} \bar{q}, \quad \sin q = i \tanh \bar{q}, \quad \cos r = \operatorname{sech} \bar{r}, \quad \sin r = i \tanh \bar{r}.$$

Also, as seen above, $\alpha = \alpha$; the formula thus is

$$\begin{aligned} \cosh \bar{a} &= \frac{1 + \tanh \bar{q} \tanh \bar{r} \cos \alpha}{\operatorname{sech} \bar{q} \operatorname{sech} \bar{r}} \\ &= \cosh \bar{q} \cosh \bar{r} + \sinh \bar{q} \sinh \bar{r} \cos \alpha, \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing, it is

$$\cos \alpha = \frac{\cosh \bar{a} - \cosh \bar{q} \cosh \bar{r}}{\sinh \bar{q} \sinh \bar{r}},$$

viz. as will presently appear, this is the formula for $\cos BOC$ in the triangle BOC .

From the above formulae

$$\cosh \bar{a} = \frac{1 - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha}{\cos q \cos r},$$

and

$$\sin \bar{A} = \frac{\cos p \sin A}{\cos b \cos c}, \quad \cos \bar{A} = \frac{\cos A + \sin b \sin c}{\cos b \cos c},$$

and the like formulae for b, c, B, C , it may be shown that in the triangle ABC we have

$$\cosh \bar{a} = \frac{\cos \bar{A} + \cos \bar{B} \cos \bar{C}}{\sin \bar{B} \sin \bar{C}}.$$

In fact, substituting the foregoing values, this equation becomes

$$\frac{(1 - \sin^2 a)(\cos A + \sin b \sin c) + (\cos B + \sin c \sin a)(\cos C + \sin a \sin b)}{\sin B \sin C \cos b \cos c} = \frac{1 - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha}{\cos q \cos r},$$

that is,

$$\begin{aligned} \cos A + \cos B \cos C - \sin^2 a \cos A + \sin a \sin b \cos B \\ + \sin a \sin c \cos C + \sin b \sin c = \sin B \sin C (1 - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha), \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} & \sin^2 a (\cos B \cos C - \sin B \sin C) + \sin a \sin b \cos B \\ & + \sin a \sin c \cos C + \sin b \sin c = -\sin B \sin C \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha, \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$(\sin a \cos B + \sin c)(\sin a \cos C + \sin b) = \sin B \sin C (\sin^2 a - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha),$$

a relation which I proceed to verify.

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We may, from the formulae

$$a^2 = \sin^2 q + \sin^2 r - 2 \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha, \quad a \sin a = \sin q \sin r \sin \alpha, \quad \&c.,$$

but, more simply, geometrically as presently shown, deduce

$$\sin a \cos B + \sin c = a^{-1} \sin B \sin q (\sin q - \sin r \cos \alpha),$$

$$\sin a \cos C + \sin b = a^{-1} \sin C \sin r (\sin r - \sin q \cos \alpha),$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} & (\sin a \cos B + \sin c)(\sin a \cos C + \sin b) \\ & = a^{-2} \sin B \sin C \sin q \sin r \{ \sin q \sin r (1 + \cos^2 \alpha) - \cos \alpha (\sin^2 q + \sin^2 r) \} \\ & = \sin B \sin C (\sin^2 a - \sin q \sin r \cos \alpha), \end{aligned}$$

which is the equation in question. For the subsidiary equations used in the demonstration, observe that the four points O, X, A', B lie in a circle, and consequently that

$$CO.CX = CA'.CB;$$

or multiplying each side by $\sin C$, then

$$CO.CX. \sin C = A'.K.CB,$$

that is,

$$\sin r (\sin r - \sin q \cos \alpha) \sin C = a (\sin a \cos C + \sin b),$$

and the other of the equations in question is proved in the same manner.

From the formula for $\cosh \bar{a}$ we find

$$\sinh \bar{a} = \frac{\Delta}{\sin B \sin C},$$

where

$$\Delta^2 = -(1 - \cos^2 A - \cos^2 B - \cos^2 C - 2 \cos A \cos B \cos C),$$

whence also

$$\sinh \bar{a} : \sinh \bar{b} : \sinh \bar{c} = \sin A : \sin B : \sin C;$$

and we can also obtain

$$\cos \bar{A} = \frac{\cosh \bar{a} - \cosh \bar{b} \cosh \bar{c}}{\sinh \bar{b} \sinh \bar{c}}.$$

So that the formulae are in fact similar to those of spherical trigonometry with only $\cosh \bar{a}, \sinh \bar{a}$ &c. instead of $\cos a, \sin a$ &c. The before-mentioned formula for $\cos \alpha$ in terms of $\bar{a}, \bar{q}, \bar{r}$ is obviously a particular case of the last-mentioned formula for $\cos \bar{A}$.

Cambridge, 11 May, 1872.

[529] A “SMITH’S PRIZE” PAPER; SOLUTIONS

[From the *Oxford, Cambridge and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics*, vol. IV. (1868), pp. 201–226.]

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1. Find the form of a function of a given number of letters, which has two and only two values.

It is required to find the general form of a function $\phi(a, b, c, \dots, k)$, rational and integral, which for all permutations whatever of the letters has two and only two values.

Suppose that any particular permutation of the letters changes $\phi(a, b, c, \dots, k)$ into $\phi_1(a, b, c, \dots, k)$; then any permutation of the letters will either leave the functions ϕ, ϕ_1 each of them unaltered, or it will change ϕ into ϕ_1 , and ϕ_1 into ϕ . Hence $\phi + \phi_1$ is a symmetrical function of all the letters, say

$$\phi + \phi_1 = 2L;$$

$\phi - \phi_1$ is a function which by any permutation of the letters is either unaltered, or simply changes its sign; and it is to be shown that, writing for shortness V to denote the product

$$(a - b)(a - c) \cdots (b - c) \cdots$$

of the differences of the letters, and denoting by $2M$ a symmetrical function of the letters, we have

$$\phi - \phi_1 = 2VM.$$

These equations give

$$\phi = L + VM,$$

which is the general form required; viz. the function ϕ has then only the two values $L + VM, L - VM$.

To prove the subsidiary theorem, observe that there is at least one interchange of two letters which changes $\phi - \phi_1$ (for otherwise $\phi - \phi_1$ would be a symmetrical function).³

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Let this be (a, b) . Then $\phi - \phi_1$, changing its sign for the interchange in question, must vanish for $a = b$, that is, $\phi - \phi_1$ must contain the factor $(a - b)$; let it contain it in the power $(a - b)^s$; then the quotient $\phi - \phi_1 \div (a - b)^s$, not vanishing for $a = b$, cannot change its sign by the interchange in question, and as by supposition $\phi - \phi_1$ does change its sign, it appears that the exponent s must be odd. But $\phi - \phi_1$, containing the factor $(a - b)^s$, must contain every other like factor $(a - c)^s$ or $(c - d)^s$; in fact, writing $\phi - \phi_1 = K(a - b)^s$, then if the interchange (a, c) alters K into K_1 , we have

$$K(a - b)^s = \pm K_1(a - c)^s;$$

and K consequently contains the factor $(a - c)^s$; it does not contain any higher power $(a - c)^{s+s'}$, for if it did, by reversing the process it would appear that $\phi - \phi_1$ contained (contrary to supposition) the factor $(a - b)^{s+s'}$. Similarly $\phi - \phi_1$ contains the factor $(c - d)^s$, but no higher power $(c - d)^{s+s'}$. Hence $\phi - \phi_1$ contains the product of all the factors $(a - b)^s$, that is, it contains V^s , and writing

$$\phi - \phi_1 = 2V^s M,$$

the quotient M does not contain any such factor as $(a - b)$; it therefore does not change its sign for any interchange whatever (a, b) ; and in consequence it remains unaltered for any such interchange,

³Set by me, for the Master of Trinity, Thursday, January 30, 1868.

that is, M is a symmetrical function. Observing that any even power of V is a symmetrical function, we may without loss of generality include V^{s-1} in the symmetrical function M , and write therefore

$$\phi - \phi_1 = 2VM,$$

which is the subsidiary theorem in question.

2. Express $\frac{x^7 - 1}{x - 1}$ as the product of two cubic factors; and show generally that, for any prime exponent p , the function $\frac{x^p - 1}{x - 1}$ may be broken up into two factors each of the order $\frac{1}{2}(p - 1)$, by means of a quadratic equation.

Let r be any root of the given equation, then

$$r^6 + r^5 + r^4 + r^3 + r^2 + r + 1 = 0;$$

the roots of this equation are $r^1, r^2, r^3, r^4, r^5, r^6$. Hence

$$x^6 + x^5 + x^4 + x^3 + x^2 + x + 1 = (x - r^1)(x - r^2)(x - r^4)(x - r^3)(x - r^5)(x - r^6),$$

and denoting the two cubic factors by y_1, y_2 , or writing

$$y_1 = (x - r^1)(x - r^2)(x - r^4), \quad y_2 = (x - r^3)(x - r^5)(x - r^6),$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} y_1 &= x^3 - x^2(r^1 + r^2 + r^4) + x(r^3 + r^5 + r^6) - 1, \\ y_2 &= x^3 - x^2(r^3 + r^5 + r^6) + x(r^1 + r^2 + r^4) - 1, \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$y_1 + y_2 = 2x^3 + x^2 - x - 2.$$

Hence y_1, y_2 are the roots of the quadratic equation

$$y^2 - y(2x^3 + x^2 - x - 2) + x^6 + x^5 + x^4 + x^3 + x^2 + x + 1 = 0.$$

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Solving the equation, observing that the quantity under the radical sign must of necessity be a square, and that its value is

$$(2x^3 + x^2 - x - 2)^2 - 4(x^6 + x^5 + x^4 + x^3 + x^2 + x + 1),$$

which is in fact

$$= -7(x^2 + x)^2,$$

we find that the roots y_1, y_2 , that is, the required cubic factors, are

$$\frac{1}{2}\{2x^3 + x^2 - x - 2 \pm \sqrt{-7}(x^2 + x)\}.$$

Generally for any prime exponent p , denoting any root by r , and writing

$$y_1 = (x - r^{a_1})(x - r^{a_2}) \cdots, \quad y_2 = (x - r^{b_1})(x - r^{b_2}) \cdots,$$

where $a_1, a_2, \dots$ are the quadratic residues, and $b_1, b_2, \dots$ the quadratic non-residues of p , we find

$$y^2 - yP + Q = 0,$$

where P is a function of x of the order $\frac{1}{2}(p - 1)$, and

$$Q = x^{p-1} + x^{p-2} + \cdots + x + 1.$$

Hence

$$y = \frac{1}{2}\{P \pm \sqrt{P^2 - 4Q}\},$$

where $P^2 - 4Q$ is a perfect square, $= \varepsilon p Z^2$, Z a rational function of a degree less than $\frac{1}{2}(p-1)$, and $\varepsilon = +$ or $-$ according as $p \equiv 1$ or $\equiv 3 \pmod{4}$. Hence the required factors are

$$\frac{1}{2}\{P \pm \sqrt{\varepsilon p} Z\}.$$

3. *In a Map of the World, wherein the meridians are projected into right lines meeting in a point, the inclination of any two of the lines being equal to that of the two meridians, and the parallels into circles about the point as centre, the radius of the circle being a given function of the colatitude: compare on the sphere and in the map (1) the corresponding elements of area, (2) the azimuths of corresponding linear elements; and explain what conveniences may be obtained by proper determinations of the above-mentioned function of the colatitude.*

Let the longitude and colatitude be

$$\text{on the sphere } l, c, \quad \text{in the map } l', c',$$

then the projection is such, that $l' = l$, $c' = f(c)$, a given function of c . The lengths of corresponding linear elements in the direction of a meridian, and perpendicular to it, are

$$dc, \quad \sin c \, dl,$$

$$dc', \quad c' \, dl.$$

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A “Smith’s Prize” Paper; Solutions (continued).

[From the Oxford, Cambridge and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics, vol. V. (1869), pp. 182–203.]

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whence, elements of area are

$$dc \sin c \, dl, \quad dc' c' \, dl',$$

tangents of azimuth are

$$\frac{dc}{\sin c \, dl}, \quad \frac{dc'}{c' \, dl'}.$$

and substituting the values $l' = l$, $c' = f(c)$, we have $dl' = dl$, $dc' = f'(c)dc$; and thence elements of area are as $\sin c : f(c)f'(c)$,

$$\text{tangents of azimuth as } \frac{dc}{\sin c \, dl} : \frac{f'(c)dc}{f(c) \, dl}.$$

By proper determinations of the function $f(c)$, we can make

- (1) The ratio of the elements of area to be constant; this will be the case if

$$f(c)f'(c) = k \sin c, \quad \text{that is, } f^2(c) = \text{const.} - 2k \cos c,$$

since $f(c)$, $= c$, must vanish for $c = 0$; that is,

$$f^2(c) = 2k(1 - \cos c);$$

- (2) corresponding azimuths to be equal; this will be the case if

$$\frac{f'(c)}{f(c)} = \frac{1}{\sin c},$$

or say

$$f(c) = k \tan \frac{1}{2}c.$$

This is in fact the stereographic projection, in which (as is known) any indefinitely small figure is in the map represented without distortion.

4. *Explain the general configuration of the contour and slope lines in a tract of Lake and Mountain country.*

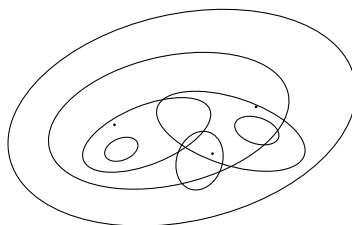
A contour line is the locus of points having a given altitude.

To fix the ideas, consider an island forming a two-headed mountain. The contour line at the sea level is a closed curve; at a sufficiently great altitude the contour line consists of two closed curves surrounding the two summits respectively; the transition from one form to the other takes place at the altitude of the pass between the two summits, the contour line then having a node at the top of the pass, and being in form a figure of eight. At the altitude of the lower summit one of the closed curves is reduced to a point, and for greater altitudes it disappears, the contour line being then a single closed curve surrounding the higher summit; and at the altitude of the higher summit this reduces itself to a point. (See fig. 1.) If there is on the breast of the mountain a lake, the contour line at the lake level is (as in

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the case of the pass) a curve with a node, having however here a closed curve with an interior loop as shown in the figure. The contour line for an altitude below the lake level includes as part of itself a closed curve lying within the contour of the lake,

FIG. 1.



and which for the altitude of the lowest point (or “imit”) of the lake reduces itself to a point, and for smaller altitudes disappears.

The contour lines in the immediate neighbourhood of a summit are in general ellipses (geometrically, the indicatrix is an ellipse); they may however be circles (viz. if the summit be an umbilicus).

A slope line is a line of greatest inclination, and it is consequently an orthogonal trajectory to the series of contour lines. A slope line may be considered as always terminated in a summit or an imit; there is through each summit (or imit) an infinity of slope lines, and in general these all touch there; if, however, the contour lines in the immediate neighbourhood are circles, then the slope lines, instead of touching, pass from the point in all directions. Through the node at the top of a pass, or outlet of a lake, there are two intersecting slope lines, one ascending each way from the node, and being in general a “ridge-line”; the other descending each way, and being in general a “course-line,” viz. in the case of a pass, it is in each direction the course of the principal stream of the valley; and in the case of a lake-outlet, it is in the direction away from the lake, the course of the out-flowing stream. The slope lines which thus pass through the several nodes mark out distinct regions, and so facilitate the tracing of the intermediate slope lines.

5. Find the differential equations corresponding to the three integral equations respectively (i) $(y + c)^2 = x(x - 1)(x - 2)$; (ii) $(y + c)^2 = x^2(x - 1)$; and (iii) $(y + c)^2 = x^3$; and discuss geometrically the singular solutions.

Generally, for the equation $(y + c)^2 - X = 0$, the derived equation is

$$X'^2 \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - 4X = 0.$$

If from the integral equation, differentiating in regard to c , we attempt to find the singular solution, we obtain $(y + c) = 0$; and thence $X = 0$ for the singular solution. It is however to be observed that, if X contain single and multiple factors,

$$X = (x + \alpha)(x + \beta) \dots (x + \gamma)^m \dots,$$

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then it is only the single factors $x + \alpha = 0$, $x + \beta = 0$, $\dots$, which are solutions of the differential equation when expressed in its proper form free from extraneous factors.

To explain how this is, write the differential equation in the form

$$X'^2 \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - 4X = 0;$$

for a single factor $x + \alpha$, X' does not contain the factor $x + \alpha$, and there is no division by $x + \alpha$. The equation $x + \alpha = 0$ gives $\frac{dx}{dy} = 0$, $X = 0$, and the equation is thus satisfied; and by what precedes $x + \alpha = 0$ is a singular solution. Contrariwise, for the multiple factor $(x + \gamma)^m$, X' will contain $(x + \gamma)^{m-1}$, and the equation $X'^2 \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - 4X = 0$ will divide by $(x + \gamma)^m$, and divested of this factor it will be of the form

$$\frac{X'^2}{(x + \gamma)^m} \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - \frac{4X}{(x + \gamma)^m} = 0,$$

where

$$\frac{X'^2}{(x + \gamma)^m}$$

contains the factor $(x + \gamma)^{m-2}$ (index is 0 or positive) but

$$\frac{X}{(x + \gamma)^m}$$

does not contain $x + \gamma$; hence the equation $x + \gamma = 0$ gives $\frac{dx}{dy} = 0$, and therefore

$$\frac{X'^2}{(x + \gamma)^m} \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 = 0,$$

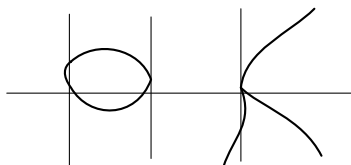
but it does not give $\frac{X}{(x + \gamma)^m} = 0$, and consequently fails to satisfy the differential equation.

Reverting to the integral equation $(y + c)^2 = (x + \alpha)(x + \beta) \dots (x + \gamma)^m \dots$, we see that $x + \alpha = 0$ touches each of the series of curves, and is thus an envelope thereof; that $x + \gamma = 0$ is not an envelope, but is the locus of a singular point on the series of curves.

Applying the foregoing considerations to the proposed equation,

(i) The differential equation is (fig. 2),

FIG. 2.



$$(3x^2 - 6x + 2)^2 \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - 4x(x - 1)(x - 2) = 0,$$

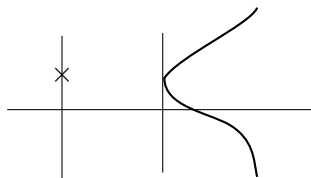
having the singular solutions $x = 0$, $x - 1 = 0$, $x - 2 = 0$.

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(ii) The differential equation is (fig. 3),

$$(3x - 2)^2 \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - 4(x - 1) = 0,$$

FIG. 3.



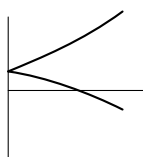
having the singular solution $x - 1 = 0$. But $x = 0$ is not a solution; it is the locus of the series of conjugate points of the curves $(y + c)^2 = x^2(x - 1)$.

(iii) The differential equation is (fig. 4),

$$9x \left(\frac{dx}{dy} \right)^2 - 4 = 0,$$

which has no singular solution. But $x = 0$ is the locus of the cusp of the curves $(y + c)^2 = x^3$.

FIG. 4.



6. Show that the curve parallel to the parabola is of the order 6 and class 4; explain the reduction of class; and trace the system of parallel curves.

The curve parallel to the parabola is the envelope of a circle of constant radius, having its centre on a parabola; taking the equation of the parabola to be $y^2 = 4x$, the coordinates of any point thereon may be taken to be $a^2, 2a$, and the equation of the variable circle is

$$(x - a^2)^2 + (y - 2a)^2 = r^2,$$

that is,

$$a^4 + a^2(-2x + 4) + a(-4y) + x^2 + y^2 - r^2 = 0,$$

or multiplying by 6, this is

$$(a, 0, c, d, e)(a, 1)^4 = 0,$$

where

$$a = 6,$$

$$c = -2x + 4,$$

$$d = -6y,$$

$$e = 6(x^2 + y^2 - r^2).$$

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The equation of the envelope is obtained by eliminating a between the equation in a and the derived equation; or, what is the same thing, by equating to zero the discriminant of the equation in a ; we thus obtain

$$(ae + 3c^2)^3 - 27(ace - ad^2 - c^3)^2 = 0,$$

which, substituting for a, c, d, e their values, is an equation in (x, y) of the order 6; the order of the curve is thus = 6.

The class is most easily obtained by geometrical considerations. Seeking the tangents which can be drawn from a given point, it at once appears that, describing about this point a circle radius r , then to each tangent through the point to the parallel curve, there corresponds a common tangent of the circle and the parabola, and reciprocally; whence the class of the curve is equal to the number of common tangents of the circle and the parabola, that is, it is = 4.

To the order 6 corresponds in general a class = 30, and the reduction from 30 to 4, = 26, is caused by the cusps and nodes of the curve.

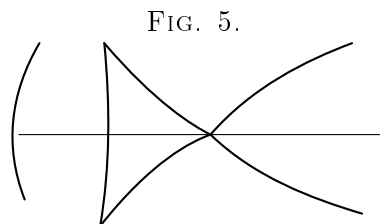
The cusps are given as the points of intersection of the curves $ae + 3c^2 = 0$, $ae - ad^2 - c^3 = 0$, which being respectively of the orders 2 and 3, give 6 cusps; it may be added that these cusps (2 real and 4 imaginary, or else all 6 imaginary) are, in regard to the parabola, the centres of curvature for those points at which the radius of curvature is = r .

There is on the axis a single point (always real) whose normal distance from the parabola is = r . Such point is a node of the parallel curve, viz. according to the value of r , either an acnode (conjugate point) or a crunode: we have thus 1 node. The parallel curve at infinity coincides with the two parabolas obtained by the displacement of the given parabola parallel to itself through the distances $+r, -r$ along the axis of y . Two such parabolas have at infinity on the axis of x a contact of the second order, equivalent to three coincident intersections; and the parallel curve has thus at infinity on the axis of x , a singular point equivalent to 3 nodes; the number of nodes is thus = 4; and the 4 nodes and 6 cusps give the required reduction $2 \cdot 4 + 3 \cdot 6 = 26$.

The parallel curve is most easily traced geometrically; there are two branches, one outside, the other inside the parabola, equidistant from it. The outside branch is a curve of continuous curvature, the form of which requires no explanation. As regards the inside branch, when r is small, this is also of continuous curvature, but there is on the axis of x inside the branch a real acnodal point (the node above referred to): when r becomes = radius of curvature at vertex (or twice the focal distance), the acnode coincides with the branch; and the point on the axis, although presenting no visible singularity, is really in the nature of a triple point composed of two cusps and a node; when r is greater than this limiting value, instead of the acnode we have a crunode;

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and two real cusps present themselves; viz. the form of the inside branch is as shown in fig. 5.



7. Show that a curve of the order n has at most $\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2)$ double points; and that in any curve having this maximum number of double points, the coordinates (x, y, z) may be taken to be proportional to rational and integral functions of a variable parameter.

A curve of the order n cannot have more than $\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2)$ double points; for suppose it had one more, say

$$\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2) + 1 = \frac{1}{2}(n^2 - 3n) + 2 \text{ double points;}$$

then since a curve of the order $n-2$ can be drawn through

$$\frac{1}{2}(n-2)(n+1) = \frac{1}{2}(n^2 - n) - 1 \text{ points,}$$

suppose it drawn through the

$$\frac{1}{2}(n^2 - 3n + 2) \text{ double points;}$$

and besides through

$$n-3 \text{ points on the curve,}$$

together

$$\frac{1}{2}(n^2 - n) - 1 \text{ points,}$$

it will cut the curve of the order n in the double points considered as

$$n^2 - 3n + 4 \text{ points,}$$

and besides in

$$n-3 \text{ points,}$$

together

$$n^2 - 2n + 1 \text{ points,}$$

that is, we should have a curve of order $n-2$ meeting the curve of the order n in $n(n-2) + 1$ points, which is of course impossible.

Consider now a curve of the order n with $\frac{1}{2}(n-1)(n-2)$ double points; draw a curve of the order $(n-2)$ through the double points; and besides through

$$\frac{1}{2}(n^2 - 3n + 2) \text{ points,}$$

together

$$n-3 \text{ points on the curve,}$$

together

$$\frac{1}{2}(n^2 - n) - 2 \text{ points,}$$

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this imposes on the curve $\frac{1}{2}(n^2 - n) - 2$ conditions; but as the curve might have been determined to satisfy $\frac{1}{2}(n + 1)(n - 2)$ conditions, this will leave still the curve indeterminate parameter λ . It meets the curve n in the double points considered as

$$n^2 - 3n + 2 \text{ points,}$$

and besides in

$$n - 3 \text{ points,}$$

altogether

$$n^2 - 2n \text{ points;}$$

that is, in

$$2 \text{ points;}$$

the coordinates of which are expressible rationally in terms of λ .

Hence since for any value whatever of λ , there is only one remaining intersection, the coordinates of this point must be rationally determinable in terms of the parameter λ ; that is, the coordinates of any point on the given curve will be rational functions of λ ; or using trilinear coordinates, the coordinates x, y, z of any point on the given curve will be proportional to rational and integral functions of λ .

8. *Show that three bodies attracting each other according to the law of gravitation may move in a line in such wise that the mutual distances are in a constant ratio the value of which depends on the masses.*

Taking the masses m_1, m_2, m_3 , to be arranged in this order at distances z_1, z_2, z_3 , from a fixed origin, the equations of motion are

$$\frac{d^2 z_1}{dt^2} = -\frac{m_2}{(z_1 - z_2)^2} - \frac{m_3}{(z_1 - z_3)^2},$$

$$\frac{d^2 z_2}{dt^2} = \frac{m_1}{(z_1 - z_2)^2} - \frac{m_3}{(z_2 - z_3)^2},$$

$$\frac{d^2 z_3}{dt^2} = \frac{m_1}{(z_1 - z_3)^2} + \frac{m_2}{(z_2 - z_3)^2}.$$

Assume

$$\frac{d^2(z_1 - z_2)}{dt^2} = -\frac{m_1 + m_2}{(z_1 - z_2)^2} - \frac{m_3}{(z_1 - z_3)^2} + \frac{m_3}{(z_2 - z_3)^2},$$

and therefore

$$z_1 - z_2 = z_2 - z_3 = z_1 - z_3,$$

then the equations become

$$\frac{d^2(z_1 - z_2)}{dt^2} = \left\{ -m_1 - m_2 + \frac{m_3}{(\lambda + 1)^2} - \frac{m_3}{\lambda^2} \right\} \frac{1}{(z_1 - z_2)^2},$$

and

$$\frac{d^2(z_1 - z_3)}{dt^2} = \left\{ \frac{m_1}{\lambda^2} - \frac{m_3}{(\lambda + 1)^2} + \frac{m_2}{(\lambda + 1)^2} - m_3 \right\} \frac{1}{(z_1 - z_3)^2},$$

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which equations will be one and the same equation if only

$$\frac{1}{\lambda + 1} \left\{ -m_1 - m_2 + \frac{m_3}{(\lambda + 1)^2} - \frac{m_3}{\lambda^2} \right\} = \frac{m_1}{\lambda^2} - \frac{m_3}{(\lambda + 1)^2} + \frac{m_2}{(\lambda + 1)^2} - m_3,$$

an equation which (multiplying out) is of the fifth order, and gives at least one real value of λ ; and λ being thus determined, we may from either equation obtain an equation of the form $\frac{d^2(z_1 - z_2)}{dt^2} = -\frac{M}{(z_1 - z_2)^2}$, which determines $z_1 - z_2$ in terms of t , and then $z_1 - z_2$, $-z_1(z_1 - z_2)$, is also known; that is, the relative motions of the three bodies are determined.

9. *Write down the integral equations for the elliptic motion of a planet; and if r , a , b , denote the radius vector, longest of the latitude, and central longitude respectively, show that*

$$\frac{\sqrt{(1+e)}}{\sqrt{r}} = \frac{1}{a(1-e^2)} \sqrt{(1+e)} + e \cos(s - \omega),$$

explaining the significations of the constants a , e , ω .

Write

a , the mean distance,

n , the mean motion = $\frac{\sqrt{\mu}}{a^{3/2}}$,

e , the eccentricity,

θ , longitude of node,

ω , longitude of perihelion in orbit,

ε , the longitude in orbit.

The position in the orbit is determined in terms of the time by means of an auxiliary quantity u , viz. writing

$$nt + \varepsilon - \omega = u - e \sin u.$$

We then have the radius vector r , and the true anomaly f , given as functions of the time by the equations

$$\cos f = \frac{\cos u - e}{1 - e \cos u},$$

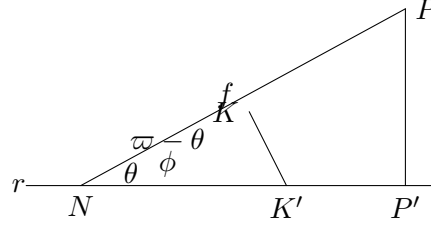
$$\sin f = \frac{\sqrt{(1-e^2)} \sin u}{1 - e \cos u},$$

$$r = \frac{a(1-e^2)}{1+e \cos f} = a(1-e \cos u).$$

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Take s , θ , the hypotenuse, base, and perpendicular of the right-angled triangle SPP' , base angle $\omega - \theta$ (see fig. 6), in which SP is the orbit, S the node, K the perihelion, P the planet; then

FIG. 6.



$\varepsilon = \omega - \theta + f$ gives s ; and so gives in terms of r, θ , by the formulæ relating to the spherical triangle, so that we have

$$\begin{aligned} \text{longitude in orbit} &= s + \theta (= \omega + f), \\ \text{reduced longitude} &= b, \\ \text{latitude} &= p. \end{aligned}$$

The expression for r , writing for f its value, $= \varepsilon - \omega$, gives

$$\frac{1}{r} = \frac{1}{a(1-e^2)} \{1 + e \cos(\varepsilon - \omega)\},$$

and we have thence

$$\frac{\sqrt{(1+e)}}{\sqrt{r}} = \frac{1}{a(1-e^2)} \sqrt{(1+e)\{1 + e \cos(\varepsilon - \omega)\}}.$$

But we have

$$1 - e = 1 - e - e + e \cos(\varepsilon - \omega).$$

And thence

$$\cos(\varepsilon - \omega) = \cos(\varepsilon - \theta) + \sin(\varepsilon - \omega) \sin(\omega - \theta).$$

Consequently

$$\begin{aligned} \sqrt{(1+e) \cos(\varepsilon - \omega)} &= \sqrt{(1+e) \cos(\varepsilon - \theta) \cos(\omega - \theta)} + \sin(\varepsilon - \theta) \sin(\omega - \theta); \\ &= \sqrt{(1+e) \cos(\omega - \theta) \cos(\varepsilon - \theta)} + \sin(\omega - \theta) \sin(\varepsilon - \theta); \end{aligned}$$

but by the right-angled triangle, we have

$$\sin(\varepsilon - \theta) \sin \phi = \sin \omega, \quad = \frac{\sin \omega}{\sqrt{(1+e)}},$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} \sin(\omega - \theta) &= \sin \phi \sin \gamma = \tan \phi \cos \theta \tan \theta, \\ \sqrt{(1+e) \cos(\omega - \theta)} &= \frac{1}{\cos \phi} + \cos \phi = \frac{\sin(\varepsilon - \theta)}{\sqrt{(1+e)}}, \\ \cos(\varepsilon - \theta) \cos(\omega - \theta) &= \cos \omega + \frac{\cos \theta \sin(\omega - \theta)}{\sin(1+e)}, \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$\sqrt{(1+e) \cos(\omega - \theta)} = 1 + e \cos(\omega - \theta).$$

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The formula thus becomes

$$\begin{aligned}\frac{\sqrt{(1+e)}}{\sqrt{r}} &= \frac{1}{a(1-e^2)} \sqrt{(1+e)\{\cos(\varepsilon-\theta)\cos(\omega-\theta) + \sin(\varepsilon-\theta)\sin(\omega-\theta)\}} \\ &= \frac{1}{a(1-e^2)} \sqrt{(1+e)\{1+e\cos(\omega-\theta)\}\cos(\varepsilon-\theta) + e\sin(\omega-\theta)\sin(\varepsilon-\theta)}, \\ &= \frac{1}{a(1-e^2)} \sqrt{(1+e) + e_1\cos(\varepsilon-\theta_1)},\end{aligned}$$

where

$$\frac{1}{\cos\phi} \tan(s-\theta) = \tan(\omega-\theta) \text{ gives } s_1,$$

$$e_1 = \frac{\cos(s-\theta)}{\cos(\omega-\theta)} \text{ gives } e_1,$$

$$e_1(1-e_1^2) = 1+e_1 \text{ gives } a_1.$$

The first equation shows that, drawing the arc KK' at right angles to SP , then

$$\varepsilon_1 = \theta + KK';$$

and therefore

$$m_1 = \theta + \sin\omega, e_1 = e\cos\phi, e_1 = TK'.$$

The other two equations then give e_1 and a_1 ; it may be added that, from the right-angled triangle NKK' we have $\cos(m_1-\theta) = \cos\phi\cos(\omega-\theta)$; and consequently that $a, (1-e) = a, (1-K')$.

10. Find the differential equations for the motion of a material line acted upon by any forces and moving in a given outer surface.

If a, b are the coordinates of the point of intersection of any line of the ruled surface with the plane of xy ; α, β, γ the cosines of the inclinations of the line to the three axes respectively; then writing

$$\frac{\beta}{a} = \alpha, \quad b - a\frac{a}{\beta} = b, \quad \frac{\gamma}{\beta} = \gamma,$$

and considering a, b, β, γ as given functions of a variable parameter θ , when a, β, γ satisfy the relation $a^2 + \beta^2 + \gamma^2 = 1$, the equations in question, coordinates of the equation ($= \varepsilon$) determine the position of the line on the surface, and taking account of the equation ($= \varepsilon$), they determine its form of the parameters θ, θ , the coordinates of a particular point in this line.

The motion of the material line is such that it must successively to coincide with the several lines on the ruled surface, consider on the material line a fixed point; say the centre of gravity G , and imagine that in the course of the motion the material line comes to coincide with the line determined as above by the parameter θ , and that the point G with the point determined as above by the parameters τ, θ , consider as

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material line any other point P whose distance from G is $= s$; the parameters of P will be $r + s, \theta$; and the coordinates will consequently be given in terms of the variable parameters r, θ , by the equations

$$\frac{x - a}{\alpha} = \frac{y - b}{\beta} = \frac{z}{\gamma} = r + s,$$

that is, we have

$$x = a + (r + s)\alpha, \quad y = b + (r + s)\beta, \quad z = (r + s)\gamma,$$

where $a, b, \alpha, \beta, \gamma$ are given functions of θ ; r, θ are parameters varying with the time, and s is a constant in regard to the time, but varies with the point under consideration. Hence, writing as usual T to denote the *Vis Viva* function

$$T = \frac{1}{2} \int (x'^2 + y'^2 + z'^2) dm,$$

where dm is the element of the material line, and x', y', z' are the velocities of the element, it only remains to express T as a function of r, θ ; and the equations of motion will be

$$\frac{d}{dt} \frac{\partial T}{\partial r'} - \frac{\partial T}{\partial r} = R, \quad \frac{d}{dt} \frac{\partial T}{\partial \theta'} - \frac{\partial T}{\partial \theta} = \Theta.$$

Using $a', b', \alpha', \beta', \gamma'$ to denote the differential coefficients in regard to θ , but, as above, x', y', z', r', θ' to denote differential coefficients in regard to t , we have

$$\begin{aligned} x' &= \{a' + (r + s)\alpha'\}\theta' + \alpha r', \\ y' &= \{b' + (r + s)\beta'\}\theta' + \beta r', \\ z' &= (r + s)\gamma'\theta' + \gamma r', \end{aligned}$$

and thence

$$x'^2 + y'^2 + z'^2 = A\theta'^2 + 2Br'\theta' + r'^2,$$

if for shortness

$$\begin{aligned} A &= a'^2 + b'^2 + 2(r + s)(\alpha a' + \beta b') + (r + s)^2(\alpha'^2 + \beta'^2 + \gamma'^2), \\ B &= a'\alpha + b'\beta + (r + s)(\alpha\alpha' + \beta\beta' + \gamma\gamma') = a'\alpha + b'\beta, \end{aligned}$$

since

$$\alpha\alpha' + \beta\beta' + \gamma\gamma' = 0.$$

Hence we have

$$T = \frac{1}{2}\theta'^2 \int A dm + r'\theta' \int B dm + \frac{1}{2}r'^2 \int dm.$$

Observing that in the sum $\int A dm$, the terms involving $\int s dm$ vanish in consequence of G being the centre of gravity, we have

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Or writing $\int dm = M$, $\int s^2 dm = Mk^2$, (M being therefore the mass of the line, and Mk^2 its moment about the centre of gravity), we have

$$\int A dm = M\{a'^2 + b'^2 + 2r(\alpha a' + \beta b') + (r^2 + k^2)(\alpha'^2 + \beta'^2 + \gamma'^2)\}.$$

Moreover

$$\int B dm = M(a'\alpha + b'\beta),$$

and hence we have

$$T = \frac{1}{2}M\{\theta'^2[a'^2 + b'^2 + 2r(\alpha a' + \beta b') + (r^2 + k^2)(\alpha'^2 + \beta'^2 + \gamma'^2)] + 2\theta'r'(a'\alpha + b'\beta) + r'^2\},$$

a given function of r, θ, r', θ' ; and the differential equations are therefore given as above.

11. *Explain the mutual connexion of the three theorems in conics: (1) the theorem at quartet linear; (2) Pascal's theorem; (3) the theorem of the anharmonic relations of four points.*

The theorem of quartet linear is that the locus of a point, such that the product of its distances from two given lines is to always in a given ratio to the product of its distances from two other given lines, is a conic.

Consider the lines as forming a quadrilateral $ABCD$. Then A, B, C, D are points on the conic, and writing PAB to denote the perpendicular distance of a point P from the line AB , and so in other cases, the theorem is that the expression

$$\frac{AC \cdot BD \sin PAB \cdot \sin PBD}{AB \cdot DC \sin PAD \cdot \sin PBC}$$

has a constant value for any point P whatever on the conic. Now the perpendicular distance $PAB = 2AB \cdot AB = AB$, or, what is the same thing, it is $= PA \cdot PB \sin PAB \div AB$; transforming the other perpendicular distances in the same manner, the distances PA, PB, PC, PD divide out, and the foregoing expression becomes

$$\frac{AC \cdot BD \sin PAB \cdot \sin PBD}{AB \cdot CD \sin PAD \cdot \sin PBC};$$

viz. omitting the constant factor, it appears that the expression

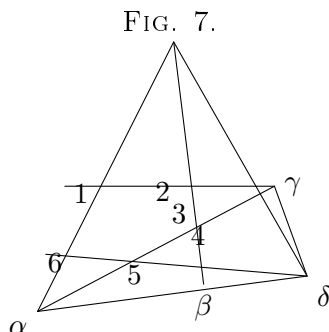
$$\frac{\sin PAB \cdot \sin PCD}{\sin PAD \cdot \sin PBC}$$

constant for all points P on the conic, or, what is the same thing, that the anharmonic ratio of the pencil $P(A, B, C, D)$ is constant for all points P on the conic. This is the anharmonic property of the points of a conic.

Pascal's theorem is that for any six points 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6 (fig. 7) on a conic, the intersections of the lines 12 and 45, the lines 23 and 56, the lines 34 and 61 lie in a line. Marking the points $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ as shown in the figure, it appears by the theorem that we have the two lines (65 $\beta\delta$), (α 547) meeting in 5, and such that the lines through the corresponding points 6 and α, β and 4, δ and γ meet in a point. Hence the ranges (65 $\beta\delta$) and (α 547) have the same anharmonic ratio; or, what is the same thing, the pencils 3(65 $\beta\delta$) and 1(α 547) have the same anharmonic ratio; that is, the pencils 3(6542) and 1(6542) have the same anharmonic ratio; or, considering 1 as a variable

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point, but 2, 3, 4, 5, 6 are fixed points on the conic, the pencil 1(6542) of lines from the point 1 to the four points 6, 5, 4, 2 has the same anharmonic ratio for all positions whatever of the variable point 1; which is the above-mentioned anharmonic property of the points of a conic.



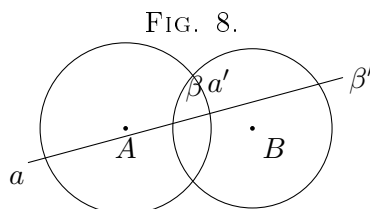
12. Show that any line through the centre of either of two orthotomic circles cuts the two circles harmonically; and connect this result with the theorem that the Jacobian of three circles is made up of the line infinity and the orthotomic circle.

Drawing through the centre of the circle A , (fig. 8) the line $a\beta a'\beta'$, it appears by the figure that we have

$$A\beta \cdot A\beta' = \text{square of tangential distance of } A \text{ from the circle } B,$$

$$= Aa'^2 \quad \text{since the circles cut at right angles,}$$

$$= Aa \cdot Aa';$$



that is, the points β, β' are inverse points in regard to the circle on the diameter aa' , and the points a, a', β, β' are thus harmonically related to each other.

Hence the polar of a , in regard to the circle B , passes through the point a' , which is the opposite of a in regard to the circle A ; and it is consequently a fixed point for all the circles B orthotomic to the circle A . That is, considering any three circles orthotomic to the circle A , this circle A is a locus of points a such that the polars of a in regard to the three circles meet in a point.

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Moreover, all circles meet the line at infinity in two fixed points I, J , the circular points at infinity: hence for any point a on the line infinity, the polar of a in regard to any circle whatever meets the line infinity in a fixed point, the harmonic of a in regard to the two points I, J ; whence the line infinity is also a locus of points a such that the polars of a in regard to the three given circles meet in a point.

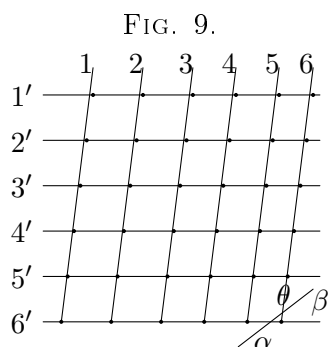
The Jacobian of any three conics is the locus of the points a , such that the polars of a in regard to the three conics meet in a point; and it is in general a cubic curve. Hence by what precedes it appears that the Jacobian of three circles is the cubic curve made up of the orthotomic circle and the line infinity.

13. *If five given lines have a common transversal, then taking the remaining transversal of each four of the given lines, show by statical considerations or otherwise that the five transversals have a common transversal.*

Consider the line $6'$ (fig. 9) meeting each of the lines 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, and take

- | | | |
|------|------------------------------|---------------|
| $1'$ | the remaining transversal of | (2, 3, 4, 5), |
| $2'$ | the remaining transversal of | (3, 4, 5, 1), |
| $3'$ | the remaining transversal of | (4, 5, 1, 2), |
| $4'$ | the remaining transversal of | (5, 1, 2, 3), |
| $5'$ | the remaining transversal of | (1, 2, 3, 4); |

it is to be shown that the lines $1', 2', 3', 4', 5'$ have a common transversal 6.



Consider the line 6 as a line determined so as to meet the lines $2', 3', 4'$ and $5'$; and take any line θ meeting each of the lines 6, $6'$; since the six lines 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, θ have a common transversal $6'$, then considering the lines as fixed lines in a solid body, it is possible to find along the lines 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, θ forces which will be in equilibrium. Suppose for a moment that the line 6, determined as above, does not meet the line $1'$; then we have the lines $1', 2', 3', 4', 5', \theta$ and 6 such that the line 6 meeting the lines $2', 3', 4', 5'$, and θ , does not meet the line $1'$. The six lines $1', 2', 3', 4', 5'$, and θ would be independent lines, such that there do not exist along them forces in equilibrium, and a force acting in any line whatever may be resolved

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into forces acting along the lines $1', 2', 3', 4', 5'$, and $6'$. Hence the original forces along the lines 1, 2, 3, 4, 5 can be each of them so resolved; and combining with the resolved forces the original force along θ , we have a system of forces along the lines $1', 2', 3', 4', 5', \theta$ in equilibrium with each other; which is impossible if the lines in question are related as above; that is, the line 6 meeting the lines $2', 3', 4', 5', \theta$ must also meet the line $1'$; which is the required theorem.

The statical principles assumed in the above demonstration are as follows:

- (1) Six lines may be such that there exist along them forces in equilibrium; or say, for shortness, the six lines may be in involution.
- (2) For any seven lines, no six or any less number of which are in involution, there exist along the lines forces in equilibrium; or, what is the same thing, given any six lines not in involution, and a seventh line; then a force along the seventh line may be resolved into forces along the six lines.
- (3) Six lines which have a common transversal are in involution (remark in passing that it is not conversely true that if the six lines are in involution they have a common transversal), but if five of the six lines have a common transversal not meeting the sixth line, then the six lines are not in involution.

14. In the theory of the variation of the arbitrary constants of a mechanical problem, state and explain the results obtained by Lagrange and Poisson respectively; and point out the peculiar advantage of Poisson's theory, in regard to the consequences which follow from the coefficients of his formulæ being independent of the time.

In the theory of the variation, of the arbitrary constants of a mechanical problem, it is assumed that the forces consist of principal and disturbing forces, each of them depending on a force function, say there is a principal force function and a disturbing function; (the assumption of a force function however is regard to the disturbing forces, though usual and convenient, is not essential); and that, when the disturbing forces are neglected, or say in the undisturbed problem, the equations of motion can be completely integrated; the theory consists herein that the same integral equations, taking the arbitrary constants to be variable, may be made to satisfy the disturbed equations of motion.

Suppose that the number of the coordinates $x, y, \dots$ is $= p$, then since the differential equations are of the second order, the number of arbitrary constants $(a, b, c, \dots)$ will be $= 2p$. In Lagrange's solution it is assumed that the coordinates $x, y, \dots$ (and consequently also the derived functions $x', y', \dots$) are each of them given in terms of t and the $2p$ constants; the disturbing function Ω is given in the same form; and the expressions for the variations $\frac{da}{dt}$, &c. are obtained by the solution of a system of linear equations

$$\frac{dR}{da} = (a, b) \frac{db}{dt} + (a, c) \frac{dc}{dt} + \&c.,$$

where the coefficients (a, b) are functions involving $\frac{dx}{da}, \frac{dx'}{da}$, &c.; these coefficients are

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time period functions of the $2p$ constants and of the time; but it is a result of the theory that they are in fact functions of the constants only, the time disappearing of itself.

In Poisson's theory it is assumed that the integrals of the undisturbed problem are obtained in the form

$$a = \phi(t, x, y, \dots, x', y', \dots), \text{ \&c.},$$

viz. that each constant is given in terms of the coordinates, their derived functions, and the time (so that, if all the integrals are known, this is equivalent to Lagrange's assumption). The expressions for the variations of the constants are given in the form

$$\frac{da}{dt} = (a, b) \frac{d\Omega}{db} + (a, c) \frac{d\Omega}{dc} + \text{\&c.},$$

where each coefficient (a, b) is given in the first instance expressed as functions of the coordinates $x, y, \dots$, the disturbing function Ω , &c. and the time; but it is a result of the theory that the coefficients (a, b) , &c. are really constant; viz. that, if $x, y, \dots, x', y', \dots$, are expressed in terms of the constants $(a, b, c, \dots)$ and of t , then the coefficient becomes a function of the constants $a, b, c, \dots$ only, the time disappearing of itself.

The transformation of the values of any coefficient $[a, b]$ requires only the knowledge of the expressions of a, b in terms of $x, y, \dots, x', y', \dots$, or we may say, the knowledge of the two integrals a, b . We thence obtain the expression of $[a, b]$ as a function of $x, y, \dots, x', y', \dots, t$, calling it, we have $\{a, b\} = \phi(t, x, y, \dots, x', y', \dots)$. But, in every transformation $[a, b]$ of the equations of motion of the undisturbed problem. It may happen that the value of $\{a, b\}$ is found to be a constant; in such case the constants of the values of the constants of the integrals all depend on the variables and the time. In every case, however, of the supposition that $\{a, b\}$ is independent of the time, leads to certain consequences analogous to this in Lagrange's theory.

15. Write a short dissertation on the transformation of rectangular coordinates in space of three dimensions, and in particular explain under what restriction it is true that two sets of rectangular axes, such that one system can by means of a rotation be made to coincide with the other, are conventionally said to be of the same kind, and that two sets of rectangular axes, such that the position of this axis and the second of the rotation cannot be made to coincide with each other, are of opposite kinds.

Two sets of rectangular axes about the same origin (each axis considered as it a line extending in the opposite sense from the origin) are said to be of the same kind if any one set can by displacement and rotation, be made to coincide with the other; in any other case they are of opposite kinds. It is easy to see that, if any one of the axes of the one set has been brought to coincide with the corresponding axis of the second set, then the other two axes will coincide with the corresponding axes,

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either the axis of z will coincide with that of z , or it will be in the opposite direction; in the former case the two sets are, in the latter case of the opposite kind, displacements one of the other. The restriction referred to in the question, is that the two sets shall be displacements one of the other.

In the problem of transformation, the two axis z axes, if not displacements, can always be made so by simply reversing the direction of one of the axes (writing for example x for x); and there is thus no real loss of generality in considering the two sets as displacements the one of the other; and it is in general convenient to make this assumption.

The transformation between two sets of rectangular axes is at once given by the diagram

	x	y	z
x'	a	β	γ
y'	a'	β'	γ'
z'	a''	β''	γ''

where a is the cosine of the inclination of the axis x , x_1 , and so for the rest of the nine quantities. The relation between the two sets of axes is obtained at pleasure by reading the diagram horizontally, $x = ax + \beta y + \gamma z$, &c. or by reading it vertically, $x = ax + a'y_1 + a''z'$, &c.

We must have identically $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = x'^2 + y'^2 + z'^2$, and we thus obtain the two equivalent sets of equations

$$\begin{array}{ll}
 a^2 + \beta^2 + \gamma^2 = 1, & a^2 + a'^2 + a''^2 = 1, \\
 a'^2 + \beta'^2 + \gamma'^2 = 1, & \beta^2 + \beta'^2 + \beta''^2 = 1, \\
 a''^2 + \beta''^2 + \gamma''^2 = 1, & \gamma^2 + \gamma'^2 + \gamma''^2 = 1, \\
 a''a' + \beta''\beta' + \gamma''\gamma' = 0, & \beta\gamma + \beta'\gamma' + \beta''\gamma'' = 0, \\
 a'a + \beta'\beta + \gamma'\gamma = 0, & a\gamma + a'\gamma' + a''\gamma'' = 0, \\
 aa' + \beta\beta' + \gamma\gamma' = 0, & a\beta + a'\beta' + a''\beta'' = 0.
 \end{array}$$

Either set leads to the relation

$$\left| \begin{array}{ccc} a, & \beta, & \gamma \\ a', & \beta', & \gamma' \\ a'', & \beta'', & \gamma'' \end{array} \right| = \pm 1, \quad \text{consequently} \quad \left| \begin{array}{ccc} a', & \beta', & \gamma' \\ a'', & \beta'', & \gamma'' \\ a, & \beta, & \gamma \end{array} \right| = \pm 1.$$

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the distinction between the two cases $+1, -1$ being that above explained; viz. if the axes are not displacements the one of the other, the sign is $+$; if they are, (and in all that follows this is assumed to be the case) then the sign is $-$. The equations give further $a = \beta'\gamma' - \beta''\gamma''$, &c. (six equations).

It is easy to see geometrically that, as stated in the question, two sets of axes (being so determined displacements the one of the other) can be made to coincide by means of a rotation of either axis through a certain axis; moreover, if the position of the axis itself is not altered by a, b, c, a and the angle of rotation, we must have

$$(b - a)x - \beta y + \gamma z = 0, \quad y(c - 1) = 0,$$

$$e'a + (\beta' - 1)y + \gamma'z = 0, \quad \&c.,$$

$$e''a + \beta''(b - 1)z = 0,$$

equations which must be equivalent to two equations; we in fact have

$$a : b : c : (a + b + 1)(a + b + 1)(c - 1) = \beta' - \gamma''(a - 1)(b + 1)(c + 1) = (1 - a)\gamma' - \beta'(c + 1),$$

as is easily verified by means of the foregoing relations between the coefficients. Any two of the three equations will then determine the ratios $a : b : c$; taking the second and third, we have

$$a : b : c = c(1 - b) - \alpha y(b - 1)\beta\gamma' : \beta'\gamma' + a'(1 - c)\gamma' + (1 - a)(1 + a)\gamma'' - 1)$$

reducible to

$$a : b : c = 1 + a - \beta'\gamma' : \beta - \alpha' : \gamma' + (1 - a)\gamma' - \beta'(c + 1)$$

and treating in the same way the third and first and second and first sets of equations the system of formulæ is

$$\begin{aligned} a : b : c &= 1 + a - \beta'\gamma' : \beta + \alpha' : \gamma' + a \\ &= a' : 1 + \beta' - a - \gamma'' \cdot y\beta + \gamma' \\ &= a' + a' : \gamma' + \alpha + a' : 1 + \gamma'' - a - \beta \end{aligned}$$

equations equivalent to each other; they determine the position of the axis in question, or resultant axis. The foregoing equations may also be written

$$a' : b' : c' : 1 = a + \beta' + \gamma' : 1 - a + \beta' + \gamma' : 1 + a - \beta' + \gamma' : 1 + a + \beta' - \gamma',$$

and hence, if A, B, C , be the inclinations of the resultant axis to the axes of x, y , and z , respectively, we have

$$\cos^2 A : \frac{1 - a + \beta + \gamma}{1 + a + \beta + \gamma}.$$

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and thence also

$$\begin{aligned}\sin^2 A &= \frac{2(1+a)}{3-a-\beta-\gamma}, \\ \cos 2A &= \frac{-1+3a-\beta-\gamma}{3-a-\beta-\gamma}, \\ a &= \cos 2A \frac{(1-a)(1+a+\beta+\gamma)+2a}{3-a-\beta-\gamma}.\end{aligned}$$

Let θ be the amount of the rotation about the resultant axis; we have a spherical triangle the two sides whereof are A, A , the included angle θ , and the opposite side $\cos^{-1} a$; that is, we have

$$\cos \theta = \frac{a - \cos^2 A}{\sin^2 A},$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned}4 \cos^2 \frac{1}{2} \theta &= 2(1 + \cos \theta) = \frac{2(a - \cos 2A)}{\sin^2 A}, \\ &= 1 + a + \beta + \gamma,\end{aligned}$$

that is, the amount of the rotation is given by the formula

$$4 \cos^2 \frac{1}{2} \theta = 1 + a + \beta + \gamma.$$

The nine cosines a, β, γ , &c. may be expressed in terms of the inclinations A, B, C , and the rotation θ , or putting λ, μ, ν equal to $\tan \frac{1}{2} \theta \cos A, \tan \frac{1}{2} \theta \cos B, \tan \frac{1}{2} \theta \cos C$, in terms of the three quantities λ, μ, ν ; but the resulting formulæ for the transformation of coordinates can be more readily obtained by other methods.

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Solution of a Senate-House Problem.

[From the Oxford, Cambridge and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics, vol. V. (1869), pp. 38-87.]

THE Problem, proposed January 7, 1869, is "If θ_1 and θ_2 are two values of θ which satisfy the equation

$$1 + \frac{\cos \theta_1 \cos \theta}{a^2} + \frac{\sin \theta_1 \sin \theta}{b^2} = 0,$$

show that θ_1 and θ_2 , if substituted for θ and ϕ in this equation, will satisfy it."

That is, writing

$$\frac{\cos \theta_1 \cos \theta}{a^2} + \frac{\sin \theta_1 \sin \theta}{b^2} + 1 = 0,$$

$$\frac{\cos \theta_1 \cos \phi}{a^2} + \frac{\sin \theta_1 \sin \phi}{b^2} + 1 = 0,$$

where $a^2 + b^2 = 1$, it is to be shown that

$$\frac{\cos \theta_1 \cos \theta_2}{a^2} + \frac{\sin \theta_1 \sin \theta_2}{b^2} + 1 = 0.$$

From the given equations, we have

$$\frac{\cos \phi}{a^2} : \frac{\sin \phi}{b^2} : 1 = \sin \theta_1 \sin \theta_2 : -\cos \theta_1 \cos \theta_2 : \sin(\theta_1 - \theta_2),$$

which is

$$= \cos \frac{1}{2}(\theta_1 + \theta_2) : -\sin \frac{1}{2}(\theta_1 + \theta_2) : 2 \cos \frac{1}{2}(\theta_1 - \theta_2).$$

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Whence eliminating ϕ , we have

$$a^2 \cos^2 \frac{1}{2}(\theta_1 + \theta_2) + b^2 \sin^2 \frac{1}{2}(\theta_1 + \theta_2) - a^2 b^2 \cos^2 \frac{1}{2}(\theta_1 - \theta_2) = 0,$$

that is,

$$a^2(1 + \cos(\theta_1 + \theta_2)) + b^2(1 - \cos(\theta_1 + \theta_2)) - (1 + \cos(\theta_1 - \theta_2)) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$a^2 + b^2 - 1 + (a^2 - b^2) \cos(\theta_1 + \theta_2) - \cos(\theta_1 - \theta_2) = 0,$$

But from the equation $a^2 + b^2 = 1$, we have

$$a^2 + b^2 - 1 = -2a^2 b^2,$$

$$a^2 - b^2 - 1 = -2b^2,$$

$$-a^2 + b^2 - 1 = -2a^2,$$

and the equation is thus

$$\frac{\cos \theta_1 \cos \theta_2}{a^2} + \frac{\sin \theta_1 \sin \theta_2}{b^2} + 1 = 0,$$

which is the required equation.

Stopping at the result obtained previous to the use of the relation $a^2 + b^2 = 1$, but making some obvious substitutions in the formula, the theorem may be presented in a more general form as follows; viz. If we have

$$\frac{ax_1}{a^2} + \frac{by_1}{b^2} - 1 = 0,$$

$$\frac{ax_2}{a^2} + \frac{by_2}{b^2} - 1 = 0,$$

where

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1 \quad \text{and} \quad \frac{x'^2}{a^2} + \frac{y'^2}{b^2} = 1,$$

then

$$\left(\frac{a}{a^2} + \frac{c}{b^2} - 1\right) \left(\frac{a'}{a^2} + \frac{c'}{b^2} - 1\right) + \left(\frac{c}{a^2} - \frac{a}{b^2}\right) \left(\frac{c'}{a^2} - \frac{a'}{b^2}\right) \left(1 - \frac{1}{a^2} - \frac{1}{b^2}\right) = 0,$$

a relation, the geometrical signification of which is: If (x, y) be a point on the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$,

and if the polar thereof in regard to the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$ meet the first-mentioned conic in the points (x_1, y_1) and (x_2, y_2) , then these points are harmonics in regard to the conic

$$\left(\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} - 1\right) \left(\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} - 1\right) - \left(\frac{x^2}{a^2} - \frac{x^2}{b^2}\right)^2 \left(1 - \frac{1}{a^2} - \frac{1}{b^2}\right) = 0;$$

and since the theorem is projective, it is seen that three conics may be any conics whatever, the third conic being a conic having with the other two a common system of conjugate points.

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If to the ideas we write $a = b = c$; then the theorem is, if the polar of a point on the circle $a^2 + y^2 = a^2$ in regard to the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, meet the circle in two points, these are harmonics in regard to the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2(a^2 + b^2 - 1)} + \frac{y^2}{b^2(a^2 + b^2 - 1)} = 1$; viz. if $a^2 + b^2 = 1$, the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, or if $a^2 = a^2$, $b^2 = b^2$, then the conic is the same similar to, but in the inverse ratio of the two points (x_1, y_1) , (x_2, y_2) harmonics in regard to the imaginary conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, but this is also an inverse form similar to the original conic, which is the theorem in question.

This last result will be similar to the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$; viz. if $a^2 + b^2 = a$, then the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$; if $a^2 = a^2$, $b^2 = b^2$, then $a^2 = a^2$, $b^2 = b^2 + b^2$; and the conic is $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$. Considering the given conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$ to be an ellipse, the first cone (a) is similar to the two points (x_1, y_1) , (x_2, y_2) harmonics in regard to the imaginary conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, viz. if $a^2 = a^2$, the conic of the right side of the equation is the same conic, but the points (x_1, y_1) , (x_2, y_2) are harmonics in regard to the imaginary conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, but this is also an inverse form similar to the original conic, which is the theorem in question.

The second case ($a^2 + b^2 = 1$) gives a real ellipse if b be negative; viz. this is, if for b we have the hyperbola $\frac{x^2}{a^2} - \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, if $a^2 + b^2$, an obtuse-angled hyperbola, the circle $a^2 + y^2 - b^2$ which is the locus of the intersection of a pair of orthotomic tangents of the hyperbola, is consequently imaginary; but the eccentric orthotomic circle hence, on the limits of the theorem, must occur to have the opposite of polar of the property of a point on the circle in regard to the orthotomic hyperbola; viz. $\frac{x^2}{a^2} - \frac{y^2}{b^2} = a^2$ also the theorem: "Given the hyperbola $\frac{x^2}{a^2} - \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$, $\frac{x^2}{a^2} - \frac{y^2}{b^2} = a^2$ and the circle $a^2 + y^2 - a^2 + a^2$ (the concentric orthotomic circle of the imaginary circle which is the locus of the intersection of a pair of orthotomic tangents of the hyperbola); if the polar in regard to the hyperbola of a point on the circle meet the circle in two points Q , R , then these are harmonics in regard to the hyperbola."

Of course, if reality be disregarded, the two theorems are mere two of the cases of a conic generally; and observe, that in the first theorem the circle is the locus of the intersection of orthotomic tangents, and we have the opposite of the points Q , R in the second theorem the circle is the locus of the orthotomic circle of the cross, which the lines of in the cross of Q , R themselves.

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A “Smith’s Prize” Paper(*) ; Solutions.

[From the Oxford, Cambridge and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics, vol. v. (1869), pp. 40-64.]

1. If $\sqrt{x - a^2 + (y + b)^2}$, $\sqrt{x - a^2 + (y - b)^2}$, a , β are respectively real and positive, show that in the equation $\sqrt{x - a^2 + (y - b)^2} = \sqrt{x - a^2 + (y + b)^2}$ is considered as representing a curve, the signs cannot either of them be assumed at pleasure to be + or be -; and distinguish the cases of the ellipse and the hyperbola.

Writing the equation in the form $\sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c$, we find

$$\begin{aligned} 2(c\sqrt{r} \pm c\sqrt{r}) &= a + b - R, \\ 2(c\sqrt{r} + c\sqrt{r}) &= a + b - R, \\ 4cr &= (c + b)^2 - R^2, \\ 4cr &= (b - c)^2 - R^2, \\ 4cr &= (a + b)^2 - R^2, \end{aligned}$$

either of which equations is the rational equation of the curve (the equation being of the fourth order, inasmuch as $S - R$ is a linear function of the coordinates). But writing the rational equation under the form $a^2 + a^2 + 2kxy + xy(c - \beta)$, $i\beta(a - x)$, j , considered as representing a curve, the curve must either pass for any pair of values of x or y be positive, or in the opposite case be negative; that is, the equations $\sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c$, will be in the one case real, in the opposite case imaginary. It is at once seen that, in either case, the original equation $\sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c$ also represents the same algebraic value, found in any arbitrary form: but from this it is at once seen, that on a given form of $\sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y}$, a determinable value, fixed as soon as the values of x and the form of the curve, a determinable value, fixed as soon as the values of x and the form of the curve, a determinable value, fixed as soon as the values of x and the form of the curve, a determinable value, fixed as soon as the values of x and the form of the curve.

* Set by me for the Master of Trinity, A.D. 1869.

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point, but 2, 3, 4, 5, 6 are fixed points on the conic, then the pencil 1 (2, 3, 4, 5, 6) of lines from the point 1 to the four points 2, 3, 4, 5 has the same anharmonic ratio for all positions whatever of the variable point 1; which is the above-mentioned anharmonic property of the points of a conic.

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The “condition for an ellipse,” is that the given length c shall be greater than the distance $\sqrt{(a+b)^2 + (\beta-b)^2}$; between the two foci; for a hyperbola that it shall be less. In the former case, for any real point of the curve, it is obvious that the relation must be $\sqrt{x} + \sqrt{y} = c$; the latter case, the latter case, we must look at the actual position of the point.

It must be observed in regard to the ellipse, that, starting from the equation $\sqrt{x} + \sqrt{y} = c$, in finding the radical equation $\frac{x}{a^2} + \frac{y}{b^2} = 1$, $\frac{x}{a^2} - \frac{y}{b^2} = 1$, we have a perfect identical equation which, starting from $\sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c$, signifies that we have

$$\sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c, \text{ that is, } \sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c, \text{ and } \sqrt{x} \pm \sqrt{y} = c,$$

but here, x being less than c , and the two signs are therefore each of them $+$, (c being positive), the two values verification applies to the hyperbola.

2. In a system of curves defined by an equation containing a variable parameter, investigate at any point the normal distance between two consecutive curves; and determine the form of the equation for a system of parallel curves.

Consider the system of curves $f(x, y, c) = 0$; then if the point x, y belongs to the curve $f(x, y, c) = 0$, and the point $x + dx, y + dy$ to the curve $f(x, y, c + dc) = 0$, we have

$$\frac{df}{dx} dx + \frac{df}{dy} dy + \frac{df}{dc} dc = 0,$$

and if the point $x + dx, y + dy$ be on the normal at (x, y) to the curve $f(x, y, c) = 0$, we have

$$dx : dy = \frac{df}{dx} : \frac{df}{dy},$$

or writing

$$dx = k \frac{df}{dx}, \quad dy = k \frac{df}{dy},$$

we have

$$k \left\{ \left(\frac{df}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{df}{dy} \right)^2 \right\} + \frac{df}{dc} dc = 0,$$

wherefore

$$k = -\frac{df}{dc} dc \div \left\{ \left(\frac{df}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{df}{dy} \right)^2 \right\},$$

and the normal distance at (x, y) of the curves c and $c + dc$ is $= \sqrt{(dx^2 + dy^2)}$, viz. it is

$$\begin{aligned} &= k \sqrt{\left\{ \left(\frac{df}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{df}{dy} \right)^2 \right\}}, \quad \text{or finally it is} \\ &= -\frac{df}{dc} dc \div \sqrt{\left\{ \left(\frac{df}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{df}{dy} \right)^2 \right\}}, \end{aligned}$$

where, if the distance in question be regarded as positive (that is, if we attend only to its absolute value), the sign is to be taken so that $\frac{df}{dc}$ shall be positive.

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If the question be given in the form $V - c = 0$ (V a function of (x, y)), we have the normal distance

$$= \pm dc \div \sqrt{\left\{ \left(\frac{dV}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dV}{dy} \right)^2 \right\}}.$$

For parallel curves, the normal distance is everywhere the same, that is, $\left(\frac{df}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{df}{dy} \right)^2$ must have a constant value for all values of (x, y) satisfying the relation $V = c$, viz. we must have identically $\left(\frac{df}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{df}{dy} \right)^2 = \phi(V)$, ϕ arbitrary; a partial differential equation to be satisfied by V in order that the system $V = c$ may be the equation of a system of parallel curves. Assuming the equation to be satisfied for any particular form of ϕ , say put θ in place, then if C a function of V , such that $\left(\frac{dC}{dV} \right)^2 \phi(V) = 1$, and the equation $f(V) = \text{Const.}$ is the same thing as $V = \text{Const.}$, it follows that the equation of the system of parallel curves may be taken to be $V = c$, where

$$\left(\frac{dV}{dx} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{dV}{dy} \right)^2 = 1.$$

3. *Two cannons (each free to recoil) differ only in weight and in the weight of the ball; and it is assumed that at any instant during the explosion the explosive force depends only on the space occupied by the vapour of the gunpowder: compare the emerging velocities of the balls; and also the emerging velocities of balls fired from the same cannon when it is free to recoil, and when it is absolutely fixed.*

Consider a single cannon.

Take M for its mass, m for that of the ball, S , s for the spaces described, backwards by the cannon and forwards by the ball, at the time t during the explosion. Then by hypothesis the explosive force, forwards on the ball and backwards on the cannon, is a function of $s + S$, $= \phi(s + S)$ suppose, or we have

$$m \frac{d^2 s}{dt^2} = \phi(s + S),$$

$$M \frac{d^2 S}{dt^2} = \phi(s + S),$$

and thence

$$\frac{d^2(s + S)}{dt^2} = \left(\frac{1}{m} + \frac{1}{M} \right) \phi(s + S).$$

Multiplying each side by $2 \frac{d(s + S)}{dt}$, integrating from $s + S = 0$, to $s + S = a$, where a is the length of the tube, and observing that the initial velocities are each $= 0$, we find

$$\left\{ \frac{d(s + S)}{dt} \right\}^2 = 2 \left(\frac{1}{m} + \frac{1}{M} \right) \int_0^a \phi(u) du,$$

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where $\frac{d\xi}{dt}$, $\frac{d\eta}{dt}$ are the velocities of the ball and cannon respectively at the instant of emergence; $\int_0^t \phi(x+S)(v+dS)$, is a constant factor in a quantity independent of the weights of the ball and cannon), and putting it = $\frac{1}{2}V$, the equation may be written

$$(v+V)^2 = \left(\frac{1}{m} + \frac{1}{M}\right) C,$$

where v , V are the velocities at the moment of emergence.

But from the equation

$$m \frac{d^2x}{dt^2} = M \frac{d^2X}{dt^2},$$

(the initial values of the velocities being each = 0), we have

$$mv = MV;$$

and hence from the foregoing equation we obtain

$$v = \frac{M}{M+m}(V+v) = \frac{M}{M+m} \sqrt{(M+m)C} = \frac{\sqrt{(MC)}}{\sqrt{m(M+m)}} \sqrt{C} = \frac{\sqrt{C}}{\sqrt{m} \sqrt{1 + \frac{m}{M}}},$$

or say

$$v\sqrt{m} = \frac{\sqrt{C}}{\sqrt{1 + \frac{m}{M}}}.$$

And similarly for the other cannon, if m_1 , M_1 be the masses of the ball and cannon, v_1 the velocity of the ball, we have

$$v_1\sqrt{m_1} = \frac{\sqrt{C}}{\sqrt{1 + \frac{m_1}{M_1}}},$$

whence

$$v\sqrt{m} : v_1\sqrt{m_1} = \sqrt{1 + \frac{m_1}{M_1}} : \sqrt{1 + \frac{m}{M}}.$$

If $m_1 = m$, $M_1 = \alpha$, then v , v_1 may be taken to be the velocities of the same ball fired from the cannon, mass M , when it is free to recoil and when it is absolutely fixed; and we have

$$v : v_1 = 1 : \sqrt{1 + \frac{m}{M}},$$

viz. the velocity in the former case is equal to that in the latter case divided by

$$\sqrt{1 + \frac{m}{M}}.$$

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4. If $X : Y : Z = a\zeta - c\xi : c\xi - a\eta : a\eta - b\zeta$, where $\xi^2 + \eta^2 + \zeta^2 = 0$, $\xi'^2 + \eta'^2 + \zeta'^2 = 0$, show that $\xi\xi'$, $\eta\eta'$, $\zeta\zeta'$, $\eta\zeta' + \eta'\zeta$, $\zeta\xi' + \zeta'\xi$, $\xi\eta' + \xi'\eta$ are proportional to quadric functions of X , Y , Z .

We have

$$\begin{aligned} Y^2 + Z^2 &= (\xi\xi' - c\xi)^2 + (a\eta - b\zeta)^2 \\ &= \xi^2(c^2 + a^2) + \eta^2(c^2 + b^2) - 2b\xi(c\xi + a\eta) - 2c\xi(a\eta + b\zeta) \end{aligned}$$

which, in virtue of the equations

$$\xi^2 + \eta^2 + \zeta^2 = 0, \quad \xi'^2 + \eta'^2 + \zeta'^2 = 0,$$

is

$$= -2\xi(c^2 + a^2)\eta\eta' - 2c\xi(c\eta + a\zeta) + a\eta(c\zeta + b\xi).$$

And again

$$\begin{aligned} YZ &= (c\xi - c\zeta)(a\eta - b\zeta) \\ &= b\xi^2(c\eta + \zeta) - b^2(a\zeta + c\eta) - b^2(c\zeta + a\eta). \end{aligned}$$

which, in virtue of the same equations, is

$$= b\xi(c\eta + \zeta) + b\zeta(c\eta - \zeta) - b\xi'\eta'(\eta' - \zeta')\eta;$$

and, forming the analogous equations by symmetry, the factor $(\xi\eta' + \xi'\eta) \cdot 2 + b^2$ divides out, and we have

$$\begin{aligned} &: \xi\xi' : \eta\eta' : \zeta\zeta' : \\ &= b^2(c\zeta - a\xi) + c^2(a\eta - b\zeta) : \dots : \dots \end{aligned}$$

which is the required theorem.

5. Two tangents of a conic are inversely related to a second conic; find the locus of the intersection of the two tangents.

In plane geometry the angle in a semicircle is, in spherical geometry it is not, a right angle: show how these conclusions follow from the solution of the above problem.

Let the equation of the first conic be $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$; its equation in line coordinates is therefore $\xi^2 + \eta^2 + \zeta^2 = 0$; or what is the same thing, the line $\alpha x + \beta y + \gamma z = 0$ will be a tangent of the conic if only $\alpha^2 + \beta^2 + \gamma^2 = 0$. Hence the equations of the two tangents being

$$\xi x + \eta y + \zeta z = 0,$$

$$\xi' x + \eta' y + \zeta' z = 0,$$

we have $\xi^2 + \eta^2 + \zeta^2 = 0$, $\xi'^2 + \eta'^2 + \zeta'^2 = 0$, and X , Y , Z the coordinates of the point of intersection of these tangents, we have

$$X : Y : Z = \eta\zeta' - \eta'\zeta : \zeta\xi' - \zeta'\xi : \xi\eta' - \xi'\eta,$$

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and thence, by the last question,

$$\begin{aligned} & \xi\xi' : \eta\eta' : \zeta\zeta' : \eta\zeta' + \eta'\zeta : \zeta\xi' + \zeta'\xi : \xi\eta' + \xi'\eta \\ &= Y^2 + Z^2 : Z^2 + X^2 : X^2 + Y^2 : -YZ : -ZX : -XY. \end{aligned}$$

Suppose that the equation of the second conic in line coordinates is

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h)(\xi, \eta, \zeta)^2 = 0,$$

the condition in order that the two lines $\xi x + \eta y + \zeta z = 0$, $\xi' x + \eta' y + \zeta' z = 0$, may be harmonically related to this conic is

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h)(\xi, \xi', \eta\eta', \zeta\zeta') = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing, it is

$$a(Y^2 + bz^2) + c(X^2 + Z^2) + c(X^2 + Y^2) - 2f \cdot YZ - 2g \cdot ZX - 2h \cdot XY = 0,$$

and by what precedes we have

$$(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2)(a + b + c) - (aX^2 + bY^2 + cZ^2 + 2fYZ + 2gZX + 2hXY) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(a + b + c)(X^2 + Y^2 + Z^2) - (a, b, c, f, g, h)(X, Y, Z)^2 = 0,$$

as the locus of the point of intersection of the two conics; the required locus is therefore a conic.

It is to be observed that the locus is that of a point which is such that the pairs of tangents from it to the two given conics respectively form a harmonic pencil; viz. if the equations of the given conics (in line coordinates) are

$$\alpha^2 + \beta^2 + \gamma^2 = 0,$$

$$(a, b, c, f, g, h)(\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^2 = 0, \quad \text{viz. } (\alpha, \beta, \gamma)^2 = 0,$$

then the equation of the required locus, or say the equation of the harmonic conic, is (in point coordinates)

$$(a + b + c)(x^2 + y^2 + z^2) - (a, b, c, f, g, h)(x, y, z)^2 = 0.$$

In particular, if the second conic be a point-pair or, say, if its equation be

$$(\alpha x + \beta y + \gamma z)(\alpha' x + \beta' y + \gamma' z) = 0,$$

then the equation of the harmonic conic is

$$(\alpha\alpha' + \beta\beta' + \gamma\gamma')(x^2 + y^2 + z^2) = (\alpha x + \beta y + \gamma z)(\alpha' x + \beta' y + \gamma' z),$$

which is satisfied by writing $(x, y, z) = (\alpha, \beta, \gamma)$, or $= (\alpha', \beta', \gamma')$, viz. the harmonic conic passes through the two points of the point-pair. And so, if the first conic be a point-pair, the harmonic conic passes through the four points of the two point-pairs.

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The equation of the first conic in point coordinates is $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$; hence, supposing as above, that the second conic is a point-pair, the intersections of the first conic with the harmonic conic are given by

$$x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0, \quad (\alpha x + \beta y + \gamma z)(\alpha' x + \beta' y + \gamma' z) = 0;$$

whence the harmonic conic has double contact with the first conic, only if each of the lines $\alpha x + \beta y + \gamma z$, $\alpha' x + \beta' y + \gamma' z = 0$, touches the first conic; or, what is the same thing, if each of the points (α, β, γ) , $(\alpha', \beta', \gamma')$ lies on the first conic.

In plane geometry, we have (in the plane) a point-pair, the two circular points at infinity; any conic through these points is a circle: the two lines harmonic in regard hereto are at right angles. Hence, by what precedes, taking one of the given conics to be the circular points at infinity, and the other conic to be any two points P, Q ; the locus of the intersection of lines through P, Q , cutting each other at right angles, is a circle; this is evidently the circle standing on PQ as diameter, or the angle in a semicircle is a right angle.

In spherical geometry we have (on the sphere) an imaginary conic $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$, called the *absolute*; any conic having double contact herewith is a circle (small circle of the sphere); two lines (arcs of great circles), harmonic in regard hereto, are at right angles. Hence, taking one of the conics to be the conic $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$ and the other to be the two points P, Q ; the locus of the intersections of the lines (arcs of great circles) through P, Q , which cut at right angles, is a spherical conic; but it is not a circle unless the points P, Q , are each of them on the conic $x^2 + y^2 + z^2 = 0$, viz. it is not a circle for any two real points whatever; that is, in spherical geometry, the angle in a semicircle is not a right angle.

6. *A mass M attached to the end A of a chain AC is placed (with the chain) on a horizontal plane, in such wise that a portion AB of the chain forms a straight line, the remaining portion BC being heaped up at B : the mass M is then set in motion in the direction B to A with a given velocity, and so moves in a straight line, dragging the chain: determine the motion; and explain the peculiarity of the dynamical problem.*

The mass attached to the end of the chain is taken to be M , and the mass of a unit of length of the chain to be $= m$; suppose also that at the commencement of the motion the distance CA is $= a$, and that at the end of the time t this distance is $= a + x$, so that the length of chain then in motion is $= a + x$, ($a < l - a$, if l be the whole length of the chain). Suppose also that the velocity at the time t is $= v$; then we have a mass $= M + m(a + x)$ moving with a velocity v ; and, in the element of time dt , this sets in motion with the velocity v a length of chain $dx = vdt$, or mass of chain $= mvdt$; if then the impulse backwards on the mass $M + m(a + x)$, and forwards on the element $mvdt$ be $= R$, we have

$$\{M + m(a + x)\} dv = -R,$$

$$mvdt \cdot v = R,$$

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that is,

$$\{M + m(a + x)\} dv + mv dx = 0,$$

or, observing that $v dt = dx$, this may be written

$$\{M + m(a + x)\} dv + mv dx = 0,$$

that is,

$$\begin{aligned} \{M + m(a + x)\}v &= \text{constant}, \\ &= (M + ma)V, \end{aligned}$$

if V be the velocity at the commencement of the motion. The equation gives, in terms of the space x , the velocity v at any time t before the whole chain is set in motion; writing it in the form

$$\{M + m(a + x)\} \frac{dx}{dt} = (M + ma)V,$$

we have

$$\{M + m(a + x)\} dx = (M + ma)V dt,$$

and putting herein $x = l - a$, the equation gives the value of t at the instant when the whole chain is set in motion; after this epoch, the mass and chain will (it is clear) move on with a uniform velocity

$$= \frac{(M + ma)V}{M + ml},$$

The foregoing equation

$$\{M + m(a + x)\} dv + (R + mv) dx = 0$$

might have been obtained at once by the consideration that the momentum is constant throughout the motion; but the method employed puts more clearly in evidence the peculiarity of the dynamical problem; viz. it is, so to speak, a problem of continuous impulse. In each element of time dt , an extraneous mass $mv dt$ is suddenly and abruptly altered (in the present problem from 0 to v); but, for the very reason that it is an infinitesimal element of mass which undergoes this abrupt change of velocity, the effect is a continuous, not an abrupt, change of velocity of the whole finite mass which is then in motion.

7. Show how an ellipse may be constructed as the envelope of a variable circle having its centre upon either of the axes; and examine the geometrical peculiarities which occur according as the major or the minor axis is made use of.

Considering the ellipse

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1,$$

the equation

$$(x - \alpha)^2 + y^2 = c^2,$$

where α and c are in the first instance arbitrary parameters, represents a circle having its centre on the major axis: in order that this may touch the ellipse, a relation must be established between α and c ; When this is done we obtain a variable circle

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(the equation of which contains a single arbitrary parameter), and this circle has the ellipse for its envelope. (On account of the symmetry in regard to the axis of x , the circle will, it is clear, touch the ellipse in two points, situate symmetrically in regard to this axis.) Now to make the circle touch the ellipse, eliminating y , we have

$$(x - \alpha)^2 + b^2 \left(1 - \frac{x^2}{a^2}\right) - c^2 = 0,$$

that is,

$$x^2 \left(1 - \frac{b^2}{a^2}\right) - 2\alpha x + \alpha^2 + b^2 - c^2 = 0,$$

which equation, considered as an equation in x , must have equal roots; that is, we must have

$$\left(1 - \frac{b^2}{a^2}\right) (\alpha^2 + b^2 - c^2) - \alpha^2 = 0;$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$-b^2\alpha^2 + a^2(c^2 - b^2)(b^2 - c^2) = 0;$$

consequently

$$c^2 = b^2 \left(1 - \frac{\alpha^2}{a^2 - b^2}\right);$$

or the required equation of the circle is

$$(x - \alpha)^2 + y^2 = b^2 \left(1 - \frac{\alpha^2}{a^2 - b^2}\right);$$

or, as this may also be written

$$(x - \alpha)^2 + y^2 = (1 - e^2) \left(\frac{a^2}{e^2} - \alpha^2\right);$$

It is to be observed that at the points of contact of the ellipse and circle, we have

$$x = \frac{a^2}{a^2 - b^2} \alpha = \frac{\alpha}{e^2}.$$

By simply interchanging a and b , it appears that when the centre is on the minor axis, the equation of the variable circle is

$$x^2 + (y - \beta)^2 = b^2 \left(1 - \frac{\beta^2}{b^2 - a^2}\right);$$

and that at the points of contact of the ellipse and circle we have

$$y = \frac{b^2}{b^2 - a^2} \beta.$$

In the case where the point is on the major axis, then attending to positive values of α , the circle remains real so long as α is $< a$. But from the formula $x = \alpha/e^2$, we have $x = a$ for $\alpha = ae^2$ and, when α becomes greater than this, the points of contact are imaginary. That is, as α passes from 0 to ae^2 , the circle is real, and

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has real contact with the ellipse; but for $\alpha = ae^2$ the circle becomes the circle of greatest curvature, touching the ellipse at the extremity of the major axis: as α becomes greater than ae^2 , the circle remains real, but the contact with the ellipse becomes ideal: $\alpha = a$, the circle reduces itself to the point form considered as an evanescent circle; and for greater values of α , the circle is imaginary.

When the centre is on the minor axis it appears in like manner that the circle is always real; but, attending to negative values of β , the circle has real contact with the ellipse only so long as β is $< -\frac{b^2}{a}$, for this value of β , the circle touches the ellipse at the extremity of the minor axis, being in fact the circle of minimum curvature; and for greater negative values of β , the contact is imaginary.

8. *Show that the number of ways in which n things can be arranged so that no one of them is in its right place, but each in the place of one of the remaining $A_n = (n-1)A_{n-1} + (n-1)A_{n-2}$, and thence $A_n = nA_{n-1} + (-1)^n \dots$*

Suppose the n things arranged as required, we may by a single transposition of two things bring a given thing, say a , into its place in the original place (the last place); and conversely every arrangement of the required form can be obtained from an arrangement in which a occupies the last place, by a transposition of a with another of the things. Now in the arrangements which then gives rise to an arrangement of the required form, either all the things $1, 2, 3, \dots, (n-1)$ are out of their original places; and we can then transpose a with any one of the things $1, 2, 3, \dots, (n-1)$; or else one of the things in its original place, and we can transpose a with b in $(n-1)$ transposes 1 and a ; or 2 is in its original place, and we can transpose a with a . And hence we have an arrangement of mass which undergoes this abrupt change of velocity, the only mode in which an arrangement of the required form is obtained. Hence if the things denote U_n , the number of arrangements in which no one of the n things is, in motion.

Now, by what precedes,

$$U_n = (n-1)U_{n-1} + nU_{n-2};$$

and it thus appears that U_n is of the form $(n-1)A_{n-1}$, and writing accordingly $U_n = (n-1)A_{n-1}$, and therefore

$$U_{n-1} = (n-2)A_{n-2}, \quad U_{n-2} = (n-3)A_{n-3},$$

we have

$$A_n = (n-1)A_{n-1} + (n-1)A_{n-2}.$$

which is the required equation for A_n . As in the question, $A_2 = 0$, $A_3 = 1$, and the successive values A , A_4 , A_5 , $\dots$ are then to be integrated into one of the first integer, by writing the equation in the form

$$\{(n-1)A_{n-1} - nA_{n-2}\} = \{(n-2)A_{n-2} - (n-1)A_{n-3}\} = \dots = \{2A_2 - 3A_1\} = -1,$$

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the integral is

$$(n-1)A_{n-1} = (n-2)A_{n-2} + (-)^{n-1},$$

and writing $n = 2$, we have $C = -1$, whence

$$(n-1)A_{n-1} = nA_{n-2} + (-)^{n-1},$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$A_n = (n-1)A_{n-1} + \frac{(-)^n}{n-1} \{A_{n-1} + (-)^{n-1}\}.$$

The foregoing very elegant proof of the equation

$$U_n = (n-1)(U_{n-1} + U_{n-2}) = (n-1)A_{n-1},$$

was unknown to me; but was given to me in the Examination; my own proof of the equation $U_n = nU_{n-1} + (-)^n$, was derived from the well-known formula

$$U_n = n! \left\{ 1 - \frac{1}{1} + \frac{1}{1 \cdot 2} - \frac{1}{1 \cdot 2 \cdot 3} + \cdots + (-)^n \frac{1}{1 \cdot 2 \cdot 3 \cdots n} \right\};$$

The theorem itself, and the two equations of differences for A_n , are due to Euler, see his memoir, "Sur une copieuse particularitiés du Calcul Magicquen," *Comm. Arith. Coll.*, t. I. p. 859.

9. If in any covariant of a binary form $(a, b, c, \dots, k)(x, y)^n$ the coefficients $a, b, \dots, k$ are replaced by $a + bp, b + cp, \dots, k + lp$ respectively, show that the result is a covariant of the next superior form $(a, b, c, \dots, l)(x, y)^{n+1}$, and determine the covariant obtained by this operation on the discriminant of the cubic form $(a, b, c, d)(x, y)^3$.

A covariant of the binary form $U' = (a, b, c, \dots, k)(x, y)^n$ is either given by a single symbolical expression of the form $\overline{12}^a \cdot \overline{13}^b \dots U_1 U_2 \dots$, or it is the sum of a number of such expressions, each multiplied by a constant numerical factor. In the latter case each of the expressions in question is a covariant of U . Any such expression is at once seen to be a function of U and of its differential coefficients (viz. it may contain the differential coefficients of any order of U , 1, 2, $\dots$, n): homogeneous as regards the differential coefficients of the same order. But writing $U' = (a, b, c, \dots, l)(x, y)^{n+1}$, the differential coefficients of any order of U' are by the change of $a, b, \dots, k$ into $a + bp, b + cp, \dots, k + lp$, converted into the differential coefficients of the same order of U , multiplied into the same numerical factor; consequently the foregoing covariant of U is, by the same change in regard to the coefficients of the same order. Any function of U and its differential coefficients of the same order, and which is therefore the same in regard to the coefficients of the order of U , becomes, by the like change in regard to the coefficients of the same order, the like covariant of U' .

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Or the same thing may be otherwise so obvious. The two of the ideas we write $U = (a, b, c, d)(x, y)^n$, any covariant Θ of U is reduced to zero by each of the operations $aD_b + 2bD_c + 3cD_d + \dots$ and $bD_a + 2cD_b + 3dD_c + \dots$. We may by writing which is then reduced to zero, a covariant Θ' of the same form U' as the function obtained, viz.

$$\Theta' = (aD_a + 2bD_b + 3cD_c + 4dD_d + \dots)(x, y)^n$$

and observing that we have identically

$$(aD_a + bD_b + cD_c + dD_d + \dots)\Theta = m \cdot \Theta,$$

or considering Θ as a function of $a, b, c, d, \dots p$ (in fact, of the $a, b, c, d, \dots$)

$$(aD_a + bD_b + 3D_d + \dots)\Theta = (a + b\rho)D_a + (b + c\rho)D_b + (c + d\rho)D_c + \dots \cdot p\Theta - m \cdot \Theta,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\{ap + b(p + q) + \dots\} = \Theta - m \cdot \Theta - 2\{(a + b\rho)D_a + (b + c\rho)D_b + (c + d\rho)D_c + \dots\}\Theta,$$

that is,

$$\{a, b, c, d, \dots\}\Theta = (a + b\rho)D_a + (b + c\rho)D_b + (c + d\rho)D_c + (d + e\rho)D_d + \dots,$$

an equation which, Θ being the form $a, b, c, d, e, f(x, y)^4$, Θ is at once seen to be reduced to zero, by each of the operations $aD_a, bD_b, cD_c + 2cD_d + 3dD_e + \dots, (a + b\rho)D_a + (b + c\rho)D_b + (c + d\rho)D_c + (d + e\rho)D_d + (e + f\rho)D_e + \dots$, that is, Θ is a covariant of $(a, b, c, d, e, f)(x, y)^4$.

The discriminant of $(a, b, c, d)(x, y)^3$ is

$$\Theta = a^2d^2 + 4ac^3 + 4b^3d - 3b^2c^2 - 6abcd;$$

making the substitution in question, it is

$$= (a + b\rho)^2(b + e\rho)^2 + 4a(c + d\rho)^3 + \dots$$

viz. it is

$$\begin{aligned} &= a^2d^2 + 4ac^3 + 4b^3d - 3b^2c^2 - 6abcd \\ &+ 2(b\rho^2d^2 + 2acd^2 - bc^2d + bd^2 + ac^2d - 3abd \cdot p + b^2d) + \dots \\ &= -3p(a^2ad - abcd - ac \cdot d^3 + ad^3) - \dots \end{aligned}$$

But there is no such irreducible covariant of the quartic function $(a, b, c, d, e, f)(x, y)^4$; and observing that we have identically

$$(ae - 4bd + 3c^2)^2 - 27(ace - ad^2 - b^2e + 2bcd - c^3)^2 = 0,$$

the covariant in question must be

$$= (ae - 4bd + 3c^2)^2 - 27(ace - ad^2 - b^2e + 2bcd - c^3)^2;$$

where $cse - bf$, etc. is the Hessian of the quartic function $(a, b, c, d, e, f)(x, y)^4$.

10. From the equations of a paraboloid, and of its parallel surface, derive (by observing, determine the curves of curvature of a paraboloid: show also that for the paraboloid $xy = aw$ (the parallel sections $x = \text{Const.}$ being rectangular hyperbolae) the curves of curvature are the intersections of the paraboloid by the spheres $a^2(x^2 + y^2 + z^2) + 2axy = \lambda$.

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The curves of curvature of the ellipsoid

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1,$$

are given as the intersection of the surface with the confocal surface

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2 - \theta} + \frac{y^2}{b^2 - \theta} + \frac{z^2}{c^2 - \theta} = 1;$$

transforming to the vertex, or writing $x + a$ in place of x , these become

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = -\frac{2x}{a},$$

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2 - \theta} + \frac{y^2}{b^2 - \theta} + \frac{z^2}{c^2 - \theta} = \frac{-2x}{a - \theta};$$

or multiplying by a and writing $\frac{a^2}{a^2} = \lambda$, $\frac{a^2}{a} = h$, the equations are

$$\frac{x^2}{h} + \frac{y^2}{\lambda} + \frac{z^2}{\lambda} = -2x,$$

$$\frac{x^2}{a + b\theta} + \frac{y^2}{\lambda + \theta} + \frac{z^2}{\lambda + \theta} = -2x;$$

or, putting herein $c = -\infty$, the equations are

$$\frac{x^2}{h} + \frac{y^2}{\lambda} = -2x,$$

$$\frac{x^2}{h - \theta} + \frac{y^2}{\lambda - \theta} - 2x = -\theta - 0,$$

viz. these equations, where θ is a variable parameter, determine the curves of curvature of the paraboloid $\frac{x^2}{h} + \frac{y^2}{\lambda} - 2x = 0$. The second equation may be replaced by

$$\frac{x^2}{(b - c)} - \frac{y^2}{m(b - c)} = 0,$$

Write in the equations $l = -m = c$; they become

$$y^2 - x^2 - 2xc = 0,$$

$$\frac{x^2}{c + \theta} - \frac{y^2}{c - \theta} - 2x = 0,$$

or, substituting from $\frac{x + a}{\sqrt{2}}$ for x , and $\frac{x - a}{\sqrt{2}}$ for y , the equations are

$$xy - c = 0,$$

$$\frac{(x + b)^2}{c + \theta} - \frac{(x - y)^2}{c - \theta} - 2c = 0,$$

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the second of which is

$$c(x^2 + y^2) - 2\theta xy + (c^2 - \theta^2) = 0,$$

which is the equation for determining the curves of curvature of the surface $xy - cz = 0$.

Writing in this equation $\theta = c(2\theta + c^2)$, it becomes

$$c(x^2 + y^2) - 2cxy(2\theta + c^2) - 4c^2\theta = 0,$$

or, as this may be written,

$$(c^2 + x^2)(c^2 + y^2) - 2cxy(c^2 + c^2) - 4c^2\theta = 0,$$

and thence

$$c^2(x^2 + y^2) + c^2(c^2 + y^2) - 2c^2(c^2 + y^2) + 2cxy - cxy(x^2 + y^2),$$

that is,

$$\theta = c(c x^2 + c y^2) + 2 c x y,$$

or combining with the equation $cz - xy = 0$ of the paraboloid, this is

$$\lambda = c(x^2 + y^2 + z^2) + 2cxy,$$

or the curves of curvature are given as the intersections of the paraboloid by the series of surfaces represented by this equation.

11. *Explain for a surface such as the ellipsoid the form of the curve of given constant slope; and in an elliptical hexing case of its principal planes horizontal determine the limits within which the curve is possible.*

At any point of a surface, the direction of the line of greatest slope is evidently at right angles to the level curve, or, what is the same thing, to the trace of the tangent plane on the horizontal plane; and the inclination of the element of the line of greatest slope is equal to that of the tangent plane to the horizontal plane. The line of given constant slope must be of course be entirely on the portion of the surface for which the inclination of the tangent plane has a value not less than the given constant slope of the curve; viz. on a closed surface such as the ellipsoid, it will (in upon a certain zone of the surface, included between two boundaries, which boundaries are the curves such that at any point thereof the inclination of the tangent plane is equal to the given constant slope; and by what precedes, the direction of the line of given constant slope, at any point where it meets the boundary, is connected with the direction of greatest slope; viz. it will in general meet the boundary at a finite angle; this implies that the point is a cusp on the curve of given constant slope; and the curve in question will be a curve as shown in the figure, passing continually from one boundary to the other, and where it reaches either boundary, turning back cusp-wise to the other boundary; the curve may in particular cases, after making a circuit, or any number of circuits of the zone, re-enter upon itself, forming a closed

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curve; but in general this is not the case, and the curve will go on as above between the two boundaries ad infinitum.

[Figure: ellipsoid zone bounded by two closed curves — diagram omitted]

In the case of the ellipsoid, the plane of xy being as usual horizontal, and the equation being

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} = 1,$$

then if λ be the given constant inclination, the boundaries are the series of points at which the inclination of the normal to the axis of z is $= \lambda$; that is, we have

$$\frac{x^2}{a^4} + \frac{y^2}{b^4} = \left(\frac{x^2}{a^4} + \frac{y^2}{b^4} + \frac{z^2}{c^4} \right) \cot^2 \lambda,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\left(\frac{x^2}{a^4} + \frac{y^2}{b^4} \right) = \left(\frac{z^2}{c^4} \right) \cot^2 \lambda + 1;$$

the boundaries are thus two detached ovals, meeting the principal sections $z = 0$, $y = 0$, in the points given by

$$\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} \cot^2 \lambda - 1 = 0, \quad \frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} \cot^2 \lambda - 1 = 0,$$

and the general form is then at once perceived.

12. *To every point of space there corresponds a plane, viz. considering the several points as belonging to a solid body which is infinitesimally displaced in any manner, the plane which corresponds to a point is the plane drawn through the point at right angles to the direction of the motion; determine the plane which corresponds to a given point; and connect the result with any general geometrical theory.*

The displacements, in the directions of the axes, of a point whose coordinates are (x, y, z) are given by the ordinary formulae

$$\begin{aligned} \delta x &= a + qz - ry, \\ \delta y &= b + rx - pz, \\ \delta z &= c + py - qx, \end{aligned}$$

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where a, b, c, p, q, r are constants which determine the particular displacement; hence if X, Y, Z are current coordinates, the plane corresponding to the point (x, y, z) is the plane through this point at right angles to the line

$$\frac{X-x}{a} = \frac{Y-y}{b} = \frac{Z-z}{c},$$

viz. it is the plane

$$(X-x)(a+qz-ry) + (Y-y)(b+rx-pz) + (Z-z)(c+py-qx) = 0,$$

or, substituting for $\delta x, \delta y, \delta z$ their values, reducing and arranging, this is

$$\begin{aligned} &X(a-ry+qz) \\ &+ Y(b-pz+rx) \\ &+ Z(c-qx+py) \\ &- (ax+by+cz) \\ &- (xy+yz+zx) = 0, \end{aligned}$$

that is, the equation of the plane corresponding to the point (x, y, z) is an equation linear in regard to the coordinates (x, y, z) of this point; and such that arranging as above in the form of a square, the coefficients which are symmetrically situate in regard to the dexter diagonal are equal and of opposite signs, or say that the coefficients form a skew symmetrical matrix.

More generally, corresponding to the point (x, y, z) we may have the plane

$$AX + BY + CZ + D = 0,$$

where A, B, C, D are any linear functions whatever ($= ax+by+cz+d$, etc.) of the coordinates (x, y, z) ; this is the general relation which is put in the analytical basis of the theory of duality; it is in fact (apart from a variable point situate as a line or a plane, etc.) the general one, to a given point there corresponds a plane not in general passing through the point; the case above considered is distinguished by the circumstance that for any point whatever the corresponding plane does pass through the point.

13. *Write down the Lagrangian equations of motion, explaining the notion, and mode of applying them; and by way of illustration deduce the equations of motion of three particles, connected so as to form an equilateral triangle of variable magnitude, moving in a plane under the action of any forces.*

The Lagrangian equations of motion are

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{d\theta'} - \frac{dT}{d\theta} &= \frac{dU}{d\theta}, \\ \frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{d\phi'} - \frac{dT}{d\phi} &= \frac{dU}{d\phi}, \end{aligned}$$

&c.,

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$\theta, \phi, \dots$ here being any independent coordinates (in the most general sense of the word) which serve to determine the position of the system at the time t ; T is the *vis viva* function, or half-sum of the mass of each particle into the square of the velocity, expressed in terms of its velocity, expressed in terms of the coordinates $\theta, \phi, \dots$ and of their differential coefficients $\theta' = \frac{d\theta}{dt}$, $\phi' = \frac{d\phi}{dt}$, &c.; T is thus a given function of $\theta, \phi, \dots, \theta', \phi', \dots$; homogeneous of the second order as regards the velocities $\theta', \phi', \dots$ &c. $\frac{dT}{d\theta}, \frac{dT}{d\phi}, \dots$ are the partial differential coefficients of T in regard to $\theta, \phi, \dots$, &c., respectively, and they are also given functions of $\theta, \phi, \dots, \theta', \phi', \dots$. U is the force-function or sum

(it being assumed that $Xdx + Ydy + Zdz$ is a complete differential; that is, that there exists a force-function U) expressed in terms of the coordinates $\theta, \phi, \dots$, and being thus a given function of these coordinates. The partial differential coefficients $\frac{dU}{d\theta}, \frac{dU}{d\phi}, \dots$, are, respectively, and are then given functions of these coordinates. The known $\frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{d\theta'}$ contain, it is clear, one (and that linearly) the second differential coefficients $\frac{d^2\theta}{dt^2}, \frac{d^2\phi}{dt^2}$, &c., the equations thus establish between the coordinates $\theta, \phi, \dots$ and their first and second differential coefficients in regard to the time t a series of relations which (with the conditions of the problem) is in time of relations of which is equal to that of the coordinates, and which therefore would be integrable by aid of the equations of condition. U is in fact a function of θ, ϕ , in terms of the time.

In the proposed case of three particles, if m_1, m_2, m_3 be their masses, r the side of the equilateral triangle, x_0, y_0 the coordinates of m_1 , $\theta + 60^\circ$ (or rather, for convenience $\theta + a$) the inclination to the axis of x of the line joining m_1 and m_2 (and consequently $\theta + b$ that of the line joining m_2 and m_3); then the coordinates of m_1, m_2, m_3 will be

$$\begin{aligned} x_1 &= x_0 + r \cos \theta, & y_1 &= y_0 + r \sin \theta, \\ x_2 &= x_0 + r \cos(\theta + a), & y_2 &= y_0 + r \sin(\theta + a), \\ x_3 &= x_0 + r \cos(\theta + b), & y_3 &= y_0 + r \sin(\theta + b). \end{aligned}$$

We have

$$\begin{aligned} T &= \frac{1}{2}m_1(x_1'^2 + y_1'^2) \\ &+ \frac{1}{2}\{(x_0' + r' \cos \theta - r \sin \theta \cdot \theta')^2 + (y_0' + r' \sin \theta + r \cos \theta \cdot \theta')^2\} \\ &+ \frac{1}{2}m_2[\{x_0' + r' \cos(\theta + a) - r \sin(\theta + a)\theta'\}^2 + \{y_0' + r' \sin(\theta + a) + r \cos(\theta + a)\theta'\}^2] \\ &+ \frac{1}{2}m_3[\{x_0' + r' \cos(\theta + b) - r \sin(\theta + b)\theta'\}^2 + \{y_0' + r' \sin(\theta + b) + r \cos(\theta + b)\theta'\}^2]. \end{aligned}$$

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a given function of $x, y, r, \theta, x'_0, y'_0, r', \theta'$; the equations of motion will be

$$U = u_1(Xdx + Ydy) + \&c.,$$

will be a given function of x, y, r, θ ; and the equations of motion will be

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{dx'_0} - \frac{dT}{dx_0} &= \frac{dU}{dx_0}, \\ \frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{dy'_0} - \frac{dT}{dy_0} &= \frac{dU}{dy_0}, \\ \frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{dr'} - \frac{dT}{dr} &= \frac{dU}{dr}, \\ \frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{d\theta'} - \frac{dT}{d\theta} &= \frac{dU}{d\theta}. \end{aligned}$$

14. From the integrals $x = a \cos t + a' \sin t$, $y = b \cos t + b' \sin t$, of the dynamical equations $\frac{d^2x}{dt^2} = -x$, $\frac{d^2y}{dt^2} = -y$, derive a simultaneous solution of the two partial differential equations

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dS}{dx} &= \left(\frac{(dS)}{(da)} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{(dS)}{(dy)} \right)^2 = -\frac{1}{2}(x^2 + y^2), \\ \frac{dS}{dy} &= \frac{a'}{a^2} \left[\left(\frac{(dS)}{(da')} \right)^2 + \left(\frac{(dS)}{(db')} \right)^2 - \frac{1}{2}(a^2 + b'^2) \right] \end{aligned}$$

Writing $S' = \int_0^t \frac{1}{2}(x'^2 + y'^2) dt$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} x &= a \cos t + a' \sin t, \\ y &= b \cos t + b' \sin t, \end{aligned}$$

as the integrals of the equations of motion

$$\frac{d^2x}{dt^2} = -x, \quad \frac{d^2y}{dt^2} = -y,$$

moreover

$$\begin{aligned} x' &= -a \sin t + a' \cos t, \\ y' &= -b \sin t + b' \cos t, \end{aligned}$$

where a, b, a', b' are the initial values of x, y, x', y' respectively $\left(x' = \frac{dx}{dt}, y' = \frac{dy}{dt} \right)$.

Hence the Principal Function

$$\begin{aligned} S &= \int_0^t \frac{1}{2}(T + U) dt \\ &= \frac{1}{2} \int_0^t \{x'^2 + y'^2 - x^2 - y^2\} dt, \end{aligned}$$

expressed as a function of x, y, a, b, t , will satisfy simultaneously the proposed partial differential equations.

We have

$$x'^2 + y'^2 - x^2 - y^2 = (a'^2 + b'^2 - a^2 - b^2) \cos 2t + 2(aa' + bb') \sin 2t,$$

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Hence

$$\begin{aligned} 4S &= \frac{1}{2}(a'^2 + b'^2 - a^2 - b^2) \sin 2t + 2(aa' + bb')(1 - \cos 2t) \\ &= (a^2 + b'^2 - a^2 - b^2) \sin t \cos t + 2(aa' + bb') \sin^2 t. \end{aligned}$$

But

$$\sin t = -x + a \cos t,$$

$$\sin t = -y + b \cos t,$$

Hence

$$\begin{aligned} (aa' + bb') \sin t &= a + b - (a^2 + b^2) \cos t, \\ (a^2 + b^2) \sin t \cos t &= a + b - (a^2 + b^2 + 2c) \cos^2 t, \end{aligned}$$

and substituting these values

$$\begin{aligned} 4S &= \frac{2 \sin t \cos t}{\sin^2 t} \cdot a^2 + b^2 - 2(a^2 + b^2) \cos^2 t + 2(a + b) \cos t \\ &\quad - (a^2 + b^2) - 2c \cos^2 t + 4(a + b) \cos t \\ &\quad - 4 \sin t \frac{\cos t}{\sin t} (a + b) - 4(a^2 + b^2) \cos t \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$S = \frac{1}{2} \frac{\cos t}{\sin t} (x^2 + y^2 + a^2 + b^2) + \frac{1}{2} \frac{1}{\sin t} (ax + by);$$

which value of S satisfies the two equations are satisfied here.

More generally, the two equations are satisfied by

$$S = u + \alpha,$$

(u an arbitrary constant) while now (u , considered as a function of the first equation, contains the three arbitrary constants u , a , b , and is thus a complete solution; and similarly considered as a solution of the second equation, it contains the three arbitrary constants u , a' , b' , and is thus a complete solution of this equation.

I venture to add a few remarks in illustration of what is required in the papers set up in an Examination.

In the latter part of question (7) (form of the equation for a system of parallel curves) it is worse than useless to say $\frac{dx}{ds} = \left(\frac{dx}{dx}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dy}{dx}\right)^2$ [p. 445] must be constant; a good and sufficient answer would be that it must be constant in virtue of the given equation $f(x, y, c) = 0$. So in question (10) (the Lagrangian equations of motion), it is not enough to write down $\frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{dx'} - \frac{dT}{dx} = \frac{dU}{dx}$; it must be explained what T , U , and ξ , η , ... respectively; but for these the equations might be (without differential equations for the determination of T , U , ξ , etc. in their natural form. The answer to a candidate should be (*shortly so*) as it is given here, not such as it might be of an adequate written explanation of his ideas to himself, but such as to be intelligible into one of the first order of mathematicians on reading it; and there is no incompatibility between these requirements; A clear and precise indication of a process of solution is very much better than a detailed solution incorrectly worked out.

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Note on the Integration of Certain Differential Equations by Series.

[From the Oxford, Cambridge, and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics, vol. v. (1869), pp. 77-82.]

THERE is a speciality in the integration of certain differential equations by series, which (though evidently quite familiar to those who have written on the subject—Ellis, Boole, Hargreaves) has not, it appears to me, been exhibited in the clearest form. To fix the ideas, consider a linear differential equation of the second order integrable in the form $y = Ax^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha-1} + \dots$ is determined by a quadratic equation, and for each value of α , the coefficients $B, C, \dots$ are given multiples of A , we have thus the general solution

$$y = A(x^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha-1}\alpha + \dots) + A'(x^{\alpha'} + B'x^{\alpha'-1} + \dots).$$

The speciality referred to is, when the two roots differ by an integer number; suppose α is the smaller root, and α' is equal to, or, more definitely the larger. Then, inasmuch as the series

$$y = Ax^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha-1} + \dots,$$

is identical in form with the general solution as above written down, it is clear that, starting with the root $\alpha = \alpha'$, the coefficients beginning with that of $x^\alpha = x^{\alpha-1}$, ought not to be any longer determinate multiples of A , but should contain a new arbitrary constant K , and thus that the series derived from the root $\alpha = \alpha'$ should be the general solution containing two arbitrary constants. The most simple case is when the substitution of the series in the differential equation leads to a relation between two consecutive coefficients of the form $\frac{B}{A} \frac{0}{a}$, which has the value $\frac{B}{A}$ are functions

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the numerators and denominators of which are factorial functions of α such that, for some coefficient $\frac{B}{A}$ preceding $\frac{C}{B}$ of the coefficient of $x^{\alpha-1}$, the denominator vanishes; suppose then that we have $\alpha = \alpha'$, then B should contain a new arbitrary constant: this being so, it is allowable to write $B = C$, $C = 0$, in giving to the differential equation the finite solution

$$y = A \left(x^\alpha + \frac{B}{A} x^{\alpha-1} + \dots \right),$$

but, if notwithstanding the evanescent factor, we carry on the series, then in the coefficient of $x^{\alpha-1}$ there occurs in the denominator the same evanescent factor, so that the coefficient of this term presents itself in the form $A \frac{C}{A} \frac{C}{B}$, = an arbitrary constant D , say $A \frac{C}{B} \cdot \frac{C}{0}$, which is essentially indeterminate); and the solution thus obtained is the form

$$y = A \left(x^\alpha + \frac{B}{A} x^{\alpha-1} + \dots + \frac{B}{A} x^{\alpha-1} \right) + K \left(x^{\alpha-1} + \frac{B}{A} x^{\alpha-2} + \dots \right),$$

viz. there is one particular solution with A and K .

Take for example the equation

$$\frac{d^2 y}{dx^2} + \frac{2}{x} \frac{dy}{dx} + y = 0, \tag{I}$$

mentioned Cambridge Math. Journal, t. II. p. 176 (1840). If the integral is assumed to be

$$y = Ax^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha+1} + Cx^{\alpha+2} + \&c.,$$

then we find

$$\begin{aligned} (\alpha + 1)(\alpha - 1) \cdot A &= 0, \\ (\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)B + \alpha A &= 0, \\ \alpha(\alpha + 3)C + (\alpha + 1)B &= 0, \\ (\alpha + 1)(\alpha + 4)D + (\alpha + 2)C &= 0, \\ &\&c. \end{aligned}$$

Hence $\alpha = -1$, or else $\alpha = 1$; the coefficients are

$$\begin{aligned} B &= \frac{-\alpha A}{(\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)}, \\ C &= \frac{-\alpha(\alpha + 1)A}{(\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 3)}, \\ D &= \frac{-(\alpha + 1)(\alpha + 2)A}{(\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 3)(\alpha + 4)}, \\ &\&c. \end{aligned}$$

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Here taking $\alpha = -1$, we are at liberty to make C and all the following coefficients $= 0$; in fact, if we commence by assuming

$$y = Ax^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha+1},$$

the equations

$$\begin{aligned}(\alpha + 1)(\alpha - 2)A &= 0, \\(\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)B + \alpha A &= 0, \\ \alpha(\alpha + 3)C &= 0, \\(\alpha + 1)(\alpha + 4)D &= 0, \\ &\&c.\end{aligned}$$

are all satisfied if only $\alpha = -1$, $B = A$, $C = \frac{-\alpha A}{(\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)}$, and we have then the finite solution

$y = A\left(\frac{1}{x} - \frac{1}{2}\right)$; but if we continue the series, retaining D to represent the indeterminate quantity $\frac{(-\alpha + 1)(\alpha + 2)A}{(\alpha - 1)(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 3)(\alpha + 4)}$, we have the solution

$$y = A\left(\frac{1}{x} - \frac{1}{2}\right) + D\left(x - \frac{1}{2}x^2 + \frac{1}{6}x^3 - \dots\right),$$

the second member of which is in fact the series derived from the root $\alpha = 1$. This series is expressible by means of an exponential, viz. we have

$$x^\alpha - \frac{1}{2}x^{\alpha+1} + \frac{1}{6}x^{\alpha+2} = \frac{1}{2}\left(\frac{x^\alpha}{a}\right)e^x = \frac{1}{2}\left(\frac{x^\alpha}{a} - \frac{1}{x}\right)e^x,$$

and the complete integral is in fact

$$y = A\left(\frac{1}{x} - \frac{1}{2}\right) + B\left(\frac{1}{x} + \frac{1}{2}\right)e^x,$$

but this result is not immediately connected with the investigation. It may however be noticed that, if we proceed in the original equation in that it has $-y$ in place of y ; there is consequently the particular solution $x = A\left(\frac{1}{x} + \frac{1}{2}\right)$, giving for the proposed equation $y = A\left(\frac{1}{x} + \frac{1}{2}\right)e^{-x}$, and we have thence the complete solution as shown.

Consider, secondly, the differential equation

$$\frac{d^2y}{dx^2} - (b^2 - \beta^2)y = 0, \tag{II}$$

(derived from the equation (I) by writing therein px^{-q} in place of y); this equation is satisfied by the series

$$y = Ax^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha+1} + Cx^{\alpha+2} + \&c.,$$

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Then $a = -1$ or $a = b + 2$, but here the series belonging to $a = -1$ contains only odd powers, the other contains only even powers of x ; hence the two series do not coalesce as in the former case, and the first series is obtained without the indeterminate symbol $\frac{0}{0}$ in any of the coefficients. We have in fact

$$\begin{aligned}(\alpha + 1)(\alpha - 2)A &= 0, \\(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)B - \beta^2 A &= 0, \\(\alpha + 3)(\alpha + 2)C - \beta^2 B &= 0, \\&\&c.\end{aligned}$$

and there is not, in the series in question for the value of $\alpha = -1$ (or other series) any evanescent factor, either in the numerator or in the denominators.

But consider, thirdly, the differential equation

$$\frac{d^2 y}{dx^2} + (q - \frac{1}{2}) \frac{dy}{dx} + (\beta^2 - pq - \frac{1}{4}) y = 0, \quad (\text{III})$$

(derived from (I) by writing therein px^{-q} in place of y). This is satisfied by the series

$$y = Ax^\alpha + Bx^{\alpha+1} + Cx^{\alpha+2} + Dx^{\alpha+3} + \&c.,$$

where $\alpha = -1$ or $\alpha = b + 2$, but here the series belonging to $a = -1$, the coefficient D should become indeterminate. The relation between the coefficients is here a relation between three consecutive coefficients, viz. we have

$$\begin{aligned}(\alpha + 1)(\alpha - 2)A &= 0, \\(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)B + (q + 2)A &= 0, \\\alpha(\alpha + 3)C + (q + 1)B + (\beta^2 - pq)A &= 0, \\(\alpha + 1)(\alpha + 4)D + (q)C + (\beta^2 - pq)B &= 0, \\(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 5)E + (q - 1)D + (\beta^2 - pq)C &= 0, \\&\&c.\end{aligned}$$

It is to be shown that in the series for $a = -1$, the expression $(q + 2)A + (\beta^2 - pq)B$ contains the evanescent factor $(\alpha + 1)$; for indeterminacy and D is indeterminate; we have in fact

$$B = \frac{-(q + 2p)A}{(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)},$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned}C &= \frac{(\beta^2 + 2)(\alpha + 1) - q(q + 2p)}{(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)\alpha(\alpha + 3)}A, \\&= \frac{-1}{a(\alpha + 3)} \left\{ (\beta^2 + 2p)A - q(\beta^2 + 2p)A + (\beta^2 - pq) \frac{q + 2p}{(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)} \right\} \frac{1}{a(\alpha + 3)}A,\end{aligned}$$

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and then

$$D = \frac{\alpha + 2}{(\alpha + 4)(\alpha + 1)} \left\{ \frac{q\alpha + 6q + 4q + p}{(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)(\alpha + 3)} - \frac{(\beta^2 + 2)(\alpha + 1)(\beta^2 + p)}{(\alpha + 2)(\alpha + 1)\alpha(\alpha + 3)} \right\} A,$$

so that the whole expression contains the factor $\alpha + 1$. But observe that in the present case, if it is allowable to write $D = 0$, the next coefficient E (depending on the assumption $D = 0$) will go to infinity; that is, instead of assuming $B = 0$, we assume $D =$ an arbitrary quantity D' , then E and the subsequent coefficients will contain terms depending on D' , and the complete form of the series belonging to $\alpha = -1$ will be

$$y = A \left(x^\alpha + \frac{B}{A} x^{\alpha-1} + \frac{C}{A} x^{\alpha-2} + \frac{D}{A} x^{\alpha-3} + \&c. \right) + D' \left(x^{\alpha-3} + \frac{E'}{D'} x^{\alpha-4} + \&c. \right),$$

where the second member in fact is the series belonging to $\alpha = 2$. It is hardly necessary to remark that the solution thus obtained can be expressed by means of exponentials, viz. that the solution is

$$y = A \left(\frac{1}{x} - \frac{1}{2}q \right) e^{-px} + D' \frac{1}{x^q} \left(\frac{1}{x} + \frac{1}{2}q \right) e^{px}.$$

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On the Binomial Theorem, Factorials, and Derivations.

[From the Oxford, Cambridge, and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics, vol. v. (1869), pp. 102-114.]

THE following was part of my course of lectures in the year 1867.

The proof commonly called “Euler’s” of the binomial theorem is as follows: the theorem is assumed to be true for positive integer indices; that is, it is assumed that for any positive integer m we have

$$(1+x)^m = 1 + mx + \frac{m(m-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c.$$

This being so, data $(1+x)^m \cdot (1+x)^n = (1+x)^{m+n}$, the equation

$$\begin{aligned} & \left[1 + mx + \frac{m(m-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c. \right] \cdot \left[1 + nx + \frac{n(n-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c. \right] \\ &= 1 + (m+n)x + \frac{(m+n)(m+n-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c. \end{aligned}$$

is true for any positive integer values whatever of m and n ; the equation is therefore true identically; and it is consequently true for all values whatever of m and n . In an m^{th} power, $a + x^n$ suppose; that is, we have

$$C^m = 1 + mx + \frac{m(m-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c.$$

where C is a constant; viz. it is independent of m ; but the value of C will of course depend upon x ; and, in order to determine it, we write $m = 1$, the equation $C = 1 + x$, so that

$$(1+x)^m = 1 + mx + \frac{m(m-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c.,$$

which is the binomial theorem in its general form.

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It is to be observed that there is not in the demonstration any employment of the so called “principle of equivalent forms,” we do not from the truth of an equation for positive integer values of m, n , infer the truth of it for any values whatever of m, n ; there is the intermediate step, that being true for the integers, it is true identically, and the identical truth of the equation depends on the circumstance that comparing on the two sides of the equation the coefficients of the successive powers of x^a, y^b , etc., these coefficients are in every case finite, rational, and integral functions of m, n .

For instance, comparing the coefficients of x^a , we have

$$m + n = 1 \cdot m + 1 \cdot n;$$

and any such equation, being true for all positive integer values of m, n , will be true identically; developing the two sides, the equation is in fact

$$m^a + na^{a-1}b + \&c. = a^a + aa^{a-1}m + aa^{a-1}n + \&c.$$

The reasoning is then perfectly good; but I remark that it is quite an easy step from the proof to that of one of the general solution as above explained: we know in fact that the equation

$$(1 + x)^{m+n} = (1 + x)^m(1 + x)^n$$

is for all integer values of m, n , satisfied, the equation

$$\begin{aligned} & \left[1 + mx + \frac{m(m-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c. \right] \cdot \left[1 + nx + \frac{n(n-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c. \right] \\ &= 1 + (m+n)x + \frac{(m+n)(m+n-1)}{1 \cdot 2}x^2 + \&c. \end{aligned}$$

To show this I introduce the factorial notation and it is readily found to be

$$[m+n]^p = [m]^p + p[m]^{p-1} \cdot [n]^1 + \frac{p(p-1)}{1 \cdot 2}[m]^{p-2} \cdot [n]^2 + \&c.,$$

and I say that, this, the *factorial binomial theorem for a positive integer index r* , is proved as easily and in the same manner as the binomial theorem for a like value of the index; or say in equation

$$(m+n)^r = m^r + rm^{r-1} \cdot n + \frac{r(r-1)}{1 \cdot 2}m^{r-2} \cdot n^2 + \&c.$$

To show then that X form the values of $[m+n]^p, [m+n]^r$, etc., successively, by what that may be termed the process of factorial multiplication; we have

$$[m+n]^1 = m+n.$$

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to obtain $[m+n]^2$ we have to multiply this by $m+n-1$; it is regarded as the first term as 1 writes the multiplier under the form $(m-1)+n$, and in regard to the second term n , under the form $m+(n-1)$; the process then stands

$$\begin{aligned} [m+n]^2 &= m \\ &\quad + n - 1 = (m-1) + n, \quad m + (n-1) \\ &\quad m(m-1) \quad mn \\ &\quad + mn \quad n(n-1) \\ &= [m]^2 + 2[m]^1[n]^1 + [n]^2. \end{aligned}$$

To form $[m+n]^3$ we have to multiply by $m+n-2$; in regard to the first term, this is written under the form $(m-2)+n$; in regard to the second term under the form $(m-1)+(n-1)$; and in regard to the third term under the form $m+(n-2)$; the product is thus obtained in the form

$$\begin{aligned} [m]^2 \cdot [m-2] &= [m]^3 \\ +2[m]^1[n]^1(m-1) &\quad + 2[m]^2[n]^1 \\ &\quad + [n]^2 \cdot m \quad + [m]^1[n]^2 \\ &\quad + [m]^2(n-1) \quad + [m]^2[n]^1 \\ +2[m]^1[n]^1(n-1) &\quad + 2[m]^1[n]^2 \\ &\quad + [n]^2(n-2) \quad + [n]^3 \\ &= [m]^3 + 3[m]^2[n]^1 + 3[m]^1[n]^2 + [n]^3; \end{aligned}$$

and so on; the law of the terms is obvious; and the numerical coefficients are in effect obtained as follows:

$$\begin{array}{ccccccc} & & & & 1, & & \\ & & & & 1, & & 1, \\ & & & & 1, & 1, & 1, \\ 1, & 1, & & & & & \\ & 1, & 2, & 1, & 1, & & \\ & & 1, & 2, & 1, & & \\ 1, & 3, & 3, & 1, & & & \\ & & & & & & \&c. \end{array}$$

viz. by precisely the same process as is used in finding the numerical coefficients in the powers $(m+n)^1$, $(m+n)^2$, $(m+n)^3$, &c.; and we thus see that for any integer value r of the index, we have a factorial binomial theorem, wherein the numerical coefficients are the same as in the binomial theorem for the same index.

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But the method of varied multiplication may be applied to the demonstration of a much more general theorem; viz. we may use it to developpe a product such as

$$(\lambda - a)(\lambda - b)(\lambda - c)(\lambda - d)(\lambda - e),$$

according to a series of products such as

$$(\lambda - a)(\lambda - \beta) \cdot (\lambda - \gamma)(\lambda - \delta)(\lambda - \epsilon),$$

$$(\lambda - a)(\lambda - \beta) \cdot (\lambda - \gamma)(\lambda - \delta)(\lambda - \epsilon - 2),$$

$$(\lambda - a)(\lambda - \beta) \cdot (\lambda - \gamma)(\lambda - \delta)(\lambda - \epsilon - 3),$$

&c.

For this purpose, starting with

$$\lambda - a = \lambda - a + a - a,$$

we multiply by $\lambda - b$, written under the form $\lambda - \alpha + a - \beta$, and then under the form $\lambda - a + (a - b)$; we have thus

$$\begin{aligned} (\lambda - a)(\lambda - b) &= (\lambda - \alpha)(\lambda - \beta) \\ &\quad + (a - \alpha) \quad (a - a + \beta - b) \\ &= 1 \quad (a - a)(a - b). \end{aligned}$$

and so on. It is easy to see that we may by instance write

$$\begin{aligned} (\lambda - a)(\lambda - b)(\lambda - c)(\lambda - d) &= (\lambda - a)(\lambda - \beta)(\lambda - \gamma)(\lambda - \delta) \\ &\quad + (a - a) \cdot (\lambda - \alpha)(\lambda - \beta)(\lambda - \gamma) \\ &\quad + (b - a)(b - \beta) \cdot (\lambda - a)(\lambda - \beta)(\lambda - \gamma) \\ &\quad + (a - a)(b - \beta) \cdot (\lambda - a)(\lambda - \beta) \\ &\quad + (c - a)(c - \beta)(c - \gamma) \cdot (\lambda - a) \\ &\quad + (a - \alpha)(b - \beta)(c - \gamma) \cdot (\lambda - a) \\ &\quad \dots \\ &\quad + 1. \end{aligned}$$

[533] (CONTINUATION)

On Factorials and Derivations.

[From the *Quarterly Journal of Pure and Applied Mathematics*, vol. XI. (1871), pp. 219–229.]

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where the symbols $()_k$ denote sums of products of the differences of an upper letter and a lower letter, θ factors in each product; and the several sums being formed as follows:

For $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha, \beta, \gamma \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}$, write $\alpha :$

β	a
γ	b
	c
	d
	e ;

the expression is

$$(x - a) + (\beta - b) + (\gamma - c) + (\delta - d) + (\varepsilon - e)$$

For $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha, \beta, \gamma \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}$, write

$\alpha, \alpha,$	b
$\alpha, \beta,$	c
$\alpha, \gamma,$	d
$\beta, \beta,$	e
$\beta, \gamma,$	
$\gamma, \gamma,$	

viz. the expression is

$$(x - a)(x - b) + (x - a)(\beta - c) + \cdots + (\gamma - d)(\gamma - e)$$

For $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha, \beta, \gamma \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}$, write

$\alpha, \alpha, \alpha,$	c
$\alpha, \alpha, \beta,$	d
$\alpha, \alpha, \gamma,$	e
$\alpha, \beta, \beta,$	
$\alpha, \beta, \gamma,$	
$\alpha, \gamma, \gamma,$	
$\beta, \beta, \beta,$	
$\beta, \beta, \gamma,$	
$\beta, \gamma, \gamma,$	
$\gamma, \gamma, \gamma,$	

viz. the expression is

$$(x - a)(x - b)(x - c) + \cdots + (\gamma - c)(\gamma - d)(\gamma - e).$$

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For $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha, \beta \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}$, write $a, a, a, a, \quad a, b, c, d$.
viz. the expression is

$$(x-a)(x-b)(x-c)(x-d) + \cdots + (\beta-b)(\beta-c)(\beta-d)(\beta-e).$$

Finally for $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}$, write $a, a, a, a, a, \quad a, b, c, d, e$.
viz. the expression is

$$(x-a)(x-b)(x-c)(x-d)(x-e),$$

which explains the law of the formation of the several coefficients. It is to be observed that in forming the development of any symbol, for instance $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha, \beta, \gamma \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}$, the first column contains the homogeneous products, θ together, of α, β, γ ; the second column the combinations (that is, combinations without repetitions) θ together of a, b, c, d, e ; the top line is a, a, c ; and to form the subsequent lines we must for any advance a into β , &c. of a Greek letter make the like advance a into b , b into c , c into d , of the corresponding latin letter.

Two particular cases of the theorem may be noticed; if the latin letters all vanish, we have, for example,

$$\begin{aligned} \text{if } a &= (x-\alpha)(x-\beta)(x-\gamma)(x-\delta)(x-\varepsilon), \\ &+ (b-a)(b-\beta)(b-\gamma)(b-\delta) \cdot H_1(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta, \varepsilon) \\ &+ (c-a)(c-\beta)(c-\gamma) \cdot H_2(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta, \varepsilon) \\ &+ (d-a)(d-\beta) \cdot H_3(\alpha, \beta) \\ &+ (e-a) \cdot H_4(\alpha) \\ &+ 1 \cdot H_5(\alpha) \end{aligned}$$

where the symbols H denote the sum of the homogeneous products of the annexed letters, taken together according to the suffix number: the last coefficient $H_5(\alpha)$ is of course $= \alpha^5$. And if the greek letters all vanish, then we have in like manner

$$\begin{aligned} (b-a)(c-a)(d-a)(e-a) &= b^4 \\ &- b^3(a+b+c+d+e) \\ &+ b^2(ab+\cdots+de) \\ &- b(abc+\cdots+cde) \\ &+ abcde. \end{aligned}$$

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where the symbols C denote the combinations of the annexed letters taken together according to the suffix number; the last coefficient $C_3(a, b, c, d, e)$ is of course $= abcde$. This is the ordinary theorem giving the expression of an equation in terms of its roots.

Confining the two theorems, if in the first theorem we express the products $(x-a)(x-\beta)(x-\gamma)(x-\delta)\cdots+a$, &c. in powers of X by means of the second theorem; or if in the second theorem we express the powers b^4, b^3 , &c. in terms of the products $(b-a)(b-b)(b-c)+(b-c)(b-d)$, &c. by means of the first theorem; then in either case we obtain certain identical relations connecting the C, H of $(\alpha, \beta, \dots)$ or of $(a, b, \dots)$.

I have mentioned the factorial notation

$$[n]^r = n(n-1)\cdots(n-r+1),$$

where r is a positive integer; a consequence of this is

$$[n]^{r+s} = [n]^r [n-r]^s,$$

where r and s are positive integers; or as this may also be written

$$[n+r]^{r+s} = [n+r]^r [n]^s.$$

Assuming this to subsist for $s = 0$, or a negative integer; first for $s = 0$, we have $[n+r]^r = [n+r]^r [n]^0$; that is, $[n]^0 = 1$, and we have for $s = -r$, we have $1 = [n+r]^r [n]^{-r}$, that is,

$$[n]^{-r} = \frac{1}{[n+r]^r},$$

and in particular, $r = 1, 2$, &c., we have

$$[n]^{-1} = \frac{1}{n+1},$$

$$[n]^{-2} = \frac{1}{(n+1)(n+2)},$$

&c., which explains the extension of the factorial notation to negative integer values of the index.

But the equation

$$[n]^{r+s} = [n]^r [n-r]^s$$

does not in any determinate manner lead to an extension of the factorial notation to fractional or other values of the index. In fact, assuming $[n]^a = \frac{\Pi a}{\Pi(n-a)}$ where Π is an arbitrary fractional symbol, the equation in question becomes

$$\frac{\Pi a}{\Pi(n-r-s)} = \frac{\Pi n}{\Pi(n-r)} \cdot \frac{\Pi(n-r)}{\Pi(n-r-s)};$$

viz. the original equation is identically satisfied, without any condition whatever being imposed upon the function Π , and on this account we have not, in the notion of the factorial with an integer index, *any sufficient basis for a theory of general differentiation*.

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A product

$$n(n-r) \cdots (n-(r-1)\nu)$$

can of course be expressed in the factorial notation, viz. it is

$$= \nu^r \left[\frac{n}{\nu} \right]^r,$$

and on this account it is not in general necessary to employ a notation such as $[n, \nu]^r$ to denote such a factorial wherein the difference of the successive factors instead of being $= -1$ is $= -\nu$; in particular cases where factorials of the kind in question are used, it may be convenient to employ such a notation. In particular it is sometimes convenient to use the notation $[n, -1]^r$ or better $[n]^r$ to denote the product

$$n(n+1) \cdots (n+r-1),$$

where the successive factors instead of being diminished, are increased by unity. It may be noticed, that reverting to this last product the order of the factors, we find

$$[n]^r = [n+r-1]^r;$$

a somewhat similar formula, but employing only the ordinary factorial notation, is obtained from the equation

$$[n]^r = n(n-1) \cdots (n-r+1)$$

by first changing the sign of n and then reversing the order of the factors; viz. we have

$$[-n]^r = (-)^r [n+r-1]^r.$$

Reverting to the process used for the development of the expression $(\)_k$ where there are two columns, the one of greek, the other of latin letters; it is to be remarked that although the order in which the successive lines are evolved is not material for the purpose of the theorem, yet that a certain definite order of evolution, has been made use of; thus in regard to $\begin{pmatrix} \alpha, \beta, \gamma \\ a, b, c, d, e \end{pmatrix}_3$, the column of greek letters, giving the homogeneous products of the second order in (α, β, γ) , was

$$\begin{array}{c} \alpha \alpha \\ \alpha \beta \\ \alpha \gamma \\ \beta \beta \\ \beta \gamma \\ \gamma \gamma \end{array}$$

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this is evolved from the top term (α, α) by a process given implicitly in Arbogast's Calculus of Derivations, and which may be termed the *rule of the last and the last but one*. Let the direction "operate on any letter," be understood to mean that the letter in question is to be changed into that which immediately follows it, but in such wise that when the letter occurs more than once, e.g. as in α, α the operation affects only the letter in the right-hand place. Then operate on the α, α in regard to α , we obtain α, β ; operate on this in regard to β , we obtain α, γ ; and in regard to α , we obtain β, β . Again we operate on α, γ in regard to γ , and obtain α, δ ; we do not operate on it in regard to α for the reason that α is not the letter immediately preceding γ . Operate on β, β in regard to β , we obtain β, γ . The next step, if the series extended to ε would be to operate on α, δ in regard to δ , obtaining α, ε ; on α, δ . Passing then to the next term β, γ , we operate in regard to γ , obtaining β, δ , and since β is the letter immediately preceding γ , we also operate in regard to β , obtaining γ, γ . Similarly if ε were admissible, β, δ would give β, ε , but it in fact gives nothing; γ, γ gives γ, δ ; thus if ε were admissible would give γ, ε and δ, δ , but it in fact gives only δ, δ , and, ε being inadmissible, the process is here concluded. The rule is, operate on the last but one letter, and when the last but one letter is that which, in alphabetical order, immediately precedes the last letter (but in this case only) operate on the last but one letter.

Taking another example, but with numbers instead of letters, and supposing the highest admissible number to be 5, then from 111 we derive as follows:

111	112	113	114	115	125	135	145	155	255	355	455	535
		122	123	124	134	144	225	245	345	445		
			222	133	224	225	244	355	444			
				223	233	234	334	344				
						333						

the original single column being here for greater convenience broken up into distinct columns; but the order of the terms, when the columns are taken one after the other in order, each being read from the top to the bottom, being the same as before; it will be noticed that the successive divisions are the partitions into 3 parts (no part exceeding 5) of the numbers 3, 4, ..., 15 respectively; the partitions being in each case obtained without repetition, and those of the same number being given, say in their numerical order (corresponding with the alphabetical order when letters are employed). It is necessary to show that the partitions will be obtained without repetitions; and that all the partitions will be obtained; for this purpose consider, for example, the partitions of 9; any one of these is either a partition 135 where the last number 5 is not a repeated number; and to this case there is a partition of 8, viz. 134, from which operating on the last we obtain 135; but there is no other partition of 8 which would give 135, the only such partition would be 125, but here, as 2 is not the number which immediately precedes 5, there is no operation on the last but one, and we do not from it obtain 135. Or else a partition of 9 is of the form 144

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where the last letter is repeated; there exists in this case no partition of 8, such that operating on the last we obtain from it 144, but there does exist a partition of 8, viz. 134, such that operating on the last but one we obtain from it 144. That is, the partition 135 must be obtained from 134, and only from 134, and the partition 144 must also be obtained from 134, and only from 134, and that without repetitions, the entire series of the partitions of 9; and so in general.

Translating the example into letters, but using for greater convenience α , &c. instead of a , α , &c. the process will be precisely the same; taking the letters to be $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta, \varepsilon$, we have

$$\begin{array}{cccccccccccccccc}
 \alpha\alpha\alpha & \alpha\alpha\beta & \alpha\alpha\gamma & \alpha\alpha\delta & \alpha\alpha\varepsilon & \alpha\beta\varepsilon & \alpha\gamma\varepsilon & \alpha\delta\varepsilon & \alpha\varepsilon\varepsilon & \beta\varepsilon\varepsilon & \gamma\varepsilon\varepsilon & \delta\varepsilon\varepsilon & \varepsilon\varepsilon\varepsilon \\
 & \alpha\beta\beta & \alpha\beta\gamma & \alpha\beta\delta & \alpha\gamma\delta & \alpha\delta\delta & \beta\beta\varepsilon & \beta\delta\varepsilon & \gamma\delta\varepsilon & \delta\delta\varepsilon & & & \\
 & & \beta\beta\beta & \alpha\gamma\gamma & \beta\beta\gamma & \beta\beta\delta & \beta\gamma\delta & \gamma\gamma\varepsilon & \delta\delta\delta & & & & \\
 & & & \beta\beta\beta & \beta\gamma\gamma & \beta\gamma\delta & \gamma\gamma\delta & \gamma\delta\delta & & & & & \\
 & & & & & & \gamma\gamma\gamma & & & & & &
 \end{array}$$

Attributing weights to the several letters, viz. to $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta, \varepsilon$ the weights 1, 2, 3, 4, 5 respectively, the several columns show the terms of the weights 3, 4, ... 15 respectively.

I have said that the foregoing rule is given implicitly in Arbogast's Calculus of Derivations; this calculus includes in fact a process for the expansion of a function

$$\phi(x + hx' + \nu x'' + kx''' + \&c.)$$

in powers of x , the expansion in question may be obtained by means of Taylor's theorem, viz.

$$\begin{aligned}
 & \phi(x + hx' + \nu x'' + kx''' + \&c.) \\
 &= \phi x \\
 &+ \frac{\phi' x}{1} (hx' + \nu x'' + kx''' + \&c.) \\
 &+ \frac{\phi'' x}{1 \cdot 2} (hx' + \nu x'' + kx''' + \&c.)^2 \\
 &+ \frac{\phi''' x}{1 \cdot 2 \cdot 3} (hx' + \nu x'' + kx''' + \&c.)^3 \\
 &+ \&c.
 \end{aligned}$$

viz. expanding the several powers of the polynomial increment, and arranging in powers of x , this is

$$\begin{aligned}
 &= \phi x \\
 &+ x' \phi' x \\
 &+ x'' [\phi' x + x' \phi'' x] \\
 &+ x''' \left[\phi' x + x' x'' \phi'' x + \frac{1}{6} x'^3 \phi''' x \right] \\
 &+ x'''' [\phi' x + (x' x''' + \frac{1}{2} x''^2) \phi'' x + \frac{1}{2} x'^2 x'' \phi''' x + \frac{1}{24} x'^4 \phi'''' x] \\
 &+ \&c.
 \end{aligned}$$

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but the object of the rule is to obtain this last-mentioned result directly, and understanding “operate in regard to a letter” to mean differentiate with regard to this letter and integrate with regard to the next succeeding letter, then the coefficients of the successive powers of x are all obtained from the first coefficient ϕx , by operating thereon according to the rule of “the last and the last but one”; thus ϕx , operating on α gives $\phi' x$, this operating in regard to α gives $\phi' x$, and in regard to α gives $\phi'' x \cdot \frac{x'}{1}$; the term $\phi'' x \cdot x'$ is to be operated upon in regard to α only, and is given $\phi'' x \cdot x''$; the other terms $\phi'' x \cdot \frac{x'^2}{2}$ operated on in regard to α gives $\phi'' x \cdot \nu x$, and in regard to α gives $\phi'' x \cdot \frac{x'^2}{2}$, and so on. But attending only to the literal parts, the terms, for instance b' , $b\nu$, νb , &c., which present themselves in the formula, are the homogeneous terms derived from ν^3 , by the rule, as originally stated, with a view to the derivation of such terms.

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A “Smith’s Prize” Paper(†); Solutions.

*[From the Oxford, Cambridge and Dublin Messenger of Mathematics, vol. v. (1870),
pp. 182–203.]*

1. Mention what forms of plane relation $\phi(x, b, c, \dots) = 0$ between the roots of a plane equation will in general serve for the rational determination of the roots; explain the case of failure; and state what information as to the roots is furnished by a plane relation not of the form in question.

In the given relation $\phi(x, b, c, \dots) = 0$ must be a wholly unsymmetrical function of the roots; that is, a function altered by any permutation whatever of the roots; or, what is the same thing, by any single interchange of two roots.

For this being so, if a, β, γ, δ , and the corresponding four values of $a, b, c, \dots$ satisfied by writing therein $a = a, b = \beta, c = \gamma$, &c., it will in general be satisfied also by writing $a = \beta, b = a, c = \gamma$, &c.; but the equation must uniquely determine each of the roots $a, b, \dots$, respectively, in a separate question which is not here considered.

The function $\phi(a, b, c, \dots)$ may be of the proper form, and yet, for particular values $a, \beta, \gamma, \dots$, be such that the given relation $\phi(a, b, c, \dots) = 0$ is satisfied, not only for the single arrangement $a = a, b = \beta, c = \gamma$, &c., but for some other arrangement,

†Set by me for the Master of Trinity, Feb. 5, 1870.

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$a = \delta, b = \gamma, c = \beta, \dots$ or for more than one such other arrangement. (For instance, if the given relation be $a + b + c - 2c = 0$, and the roots are 3, 5, 7; the relation is satisfied by $a = 5, b = 3, c = 7$, and also by $a = 3, b = 7, c = 5$.) Here the given equation and relation do not completely determine each root, they only determine that a is $= a$ or $= \delta$ (or as the case may be $=$ some other one value); and similarly that b is $= \beta$ or $= \gamma$ (or as the case may be $=$ some other one value), and so for the other roots $c, d, \dots$; and it then appears *a priori*, that in such a case each root is determined, not rationally, but by means of an equation, the order of which is equal to the number of the values of such root; we have here the case of failure of the general theorem.

When the given relation $\phi(a, b, c, \dots) = 0$ is not of the required form; that is, when $\phi(a, b, c, \dots)$ is a partially symmetrical function, there will be in general several arrangements of $a, \beta, \gamma, \dots$, such that equating $\phi(a, b, c, \dots) = 0$ will be satisfied; for each of these arrangements, the given relation $\phi(a, b, c, \dots) = 0$ will be satisfied; and it follows that each of the roots $a, b, c, \dots$ is determined not rationally, but by means of an equation of a certain order (not always quadratic equation for the several values of each of the several arrangements, and as the same value, viz., that is, if it be satisfied, suppose by $a = \alpha, b = \beta, c = \gamma, \dots$, it will also be satisfied by $a = \beta, b = \alpha, c = \gamma, \dots$, but not in general in any other manner; each of the roots a, b has here either of the values a, β , and the two roots a, b in question will be given, not rationally, but by means of the same quadratic equation. And observe, moreover, that any other function $\psi(a, b, c, \dots)$ of the same form as ϕ , that is, symmetrical in regard to the two roots a, b , will have for its two arrangements $a = \alpha, b = \beta$, and $a = \beta, b = \alpha$, the same value, $c = \gamma, \dots$ acquire not two distinct values, but one and the same value, the value of $\psi(\alpha, \beta, c, \dots)$ will be determined *rationally*; and so in general.

There is for the partially symmetrical function $\phi(a, b, c, \dots)$ a case of failure similar to that which arises for the completely unsymmetrical function, viz. the particular values $a, \beta, \gamma, \dots$ may be such as to give more ways of satisfying the given relation $\phi(a, b, c, \dots) = 0$, than there would be in general for partially symmetrical values of $a, \beta, \gamma, \dots$ and there is a corresponding elevation of the order of the equation for the determination of the roots $a, b, c, \dots$ or some of them.

2. If the roots of $(a, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$ of the equation

$$(a, b, c, d, e)(x, 1)^4 = 0$$

are no two of them equal; and if there exist unequal magnitudes θ, ϕ such that

$$(\theta + \alpha)^4 : (\theta + \beta)^4 : (\theta + \gamma)^4 : (\theta + \delta)^4 = (\phi + \alpha)^4 : (\phi + \beta)^4 : (\phi + \gamma)^4 : (\phi + \delta)^4;$$

show that the cubinvariant $ace - ad^2 - b^2e - c^3 + 2bcd$ is $= 0$; and find the values of θ, ϕ .

We have

$$\left(\frac{\theta + \alpha}{\phi + \alpha}\right)^4 = \left(\frac{\theta + \beta}{\phi + \beta}\right)^4 = \left(\frac{\theta + \gamma}{\phi + \gamma}\right)^4 = \left(\frac{\theta + \delta}{\phi + \delta}\right)^4;$$

and we cannot have any two of the fourth roots, say $\frac{\theta + \alpha}{\phi + \alpha}$ and $\frac{\theta + \beta}{\phi + \beta}$ equal to each other; for this would imply $(\theta - \phi)(a - \beta) = 0$, that is, $\theta = \phi$ or else $\alpha = \beta$.

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Hence assuming $\frac{\theta + \alpha}{\phi + \alpha} = a_1, \frac{\theta + \beta}{\phi + \beta} = a_2, \frac{\theta + \gamma}{\phi + \gamma} = a_3, \frac{\theta + \delta}{\phi + \delta} = a_4$, viz. this is one of three notations of equations; the other two may be obtained from a_4 by writing a_3, a_2, a_1 , or by interchanging some of the roots, a_1, a_2, a_3, a_4 are in fact the imaginary fourth roots of unity, and the corresponding four values of $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$ is therefore equal to four values a, b, c, d . We have therefore

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{\theta + \alpha}{\phi + \alpha} &= -1, & \frac{\theta + \beta}{\phi + \beta} &= +1 \\ \frac{\theta + \gamma}{\phi + \gamma} &= -\sqrt{-1}, & \frac{\theta + \delta}{\phi + \delta} &= +\sqrt{-1} \end{aligned}$$

which are different cases, related to each other; the mathematic ratio of $(\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta)$ is therefore equal to that of $(1, -1, \sqrt{-1}, -\sqrt{-1})$;

That is,

$$(\alpha - \gamma)(\beta - \delta) = (-1 - \sqrt{-1})(1 + \sqrt{-1})$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$2(\alpha\beta + \gamma\delta) = (\alpha + \beta)(\gamma + \delta);$$

viz. we have this relation, or one of the like relations

$$2(\alpha\gamma + \beta\delta) = (\alpha + \gamma)(\beta + \delta),$$

$$2(\alpha\delta + \beta\gamma) = (\alpha + \delta)(\beta + \gamma),$$

that is, the product of the three functions $2(\alpha\beta + \gamma\delta) - (\alpha + \beta)(\gamma + \delta)$, &c. is = 0.

But the product of these is the cubinvariant of the quartic function (a, b, c, d, e) . viz. we have this relation, or one of the two following: $J = 0$,

$$J = ace - ad^2 - b^2e - c^3 + 2bcd,$$

which is evidently a transcendental curve; it may however be shown that, if

$$x^4 + y^4 = 1$$

and

$$x(1 + x^2) + y(1 + y^2) - 2xy(1 + x + y)(1 + x + y) = 0,$$

that is, if we have the equation $\frac{\theta + \alpha}{\phi + \alpha} = -1$, etc. then there is a relation in y which gives $J = 0$.

By the consideration of the form $-r^4 - r^4 - r^4 - r^4 + r^4 + r^4 + r^4 + r^4 = 0$, which is the form $J = 0$ as it may by any means easy to prove that this is so. The question depends on the form of the curve defined by the equation

$$4y^4 - 4z(z + by^2 + cy^2) = 0.$$

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That is,

$$2b\phi + 2a\theta - (\theta + \phi)(a + \beta) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$2b\phi + 2a\theta - (\theta + \phi)(\gamma + \delta) = 0;$$

viz. we have thus the values of $\theta\phi$, $\theta + \phi$ each given in terms of (a, β) corresponding to the relation $2(a\beta + \gamma\delta) = (a + \beta)(\gamma + \delta)$; and there are by cyclically permuting X, Y, Z as before, we have the values of $\theta\phi$, $\theta + \phi$ corresponding to the other two forms respectively of the relation between the roots.

3. If on a plane A, B, C, D are fixed points and P a variable point, find the locus relations

$$\alpha \cdot PAB + \beta \cdot PBC + \gamma \cdot PCD + \delta \cdot PDA = 0$$

which connects the areas of the triangles PAB, PBC, PCD, PDA .

Taking $(x, y), (x_1, y_1), (x_2, y_2), (x_3, y_3), (x_4, y_4)$ for the coordinates of P, A, B, C, D respectively, we have

$$PAB = \frac{1}{2} \begin{vmatrix} x & y & 1 \\ x_1 & y_1 & 1 \\ x_2 & y_2 & 1 \end{vmatrix}, \quad \text{etc., suppose,}$$

$$PBC = 023, \text{ \&c.}$$

(where the values of these numerical determinants do depend the signs of the several triangles). The identical equation is

$$\alpha \cdot 012 + \beta \cdot 023 + \gamma \cdot 034 + \delta \cdot 041 = 0$$

(that such an equation exists appears at once by the consideration that $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$ can be determined so that the coefficients of x, y , and the constant term shall severally vanish); and in order actually to find the values we may take P coincident with the points A, B, C, D respectively. We have thus

$$\begin{aligned} \beta \cdot 123 + \gamma \cdot 134 + \delta \cdot 141 &= 0, \\ \gamma \cdot 234 + \delta \cdot 241 + \alpha \cdot 212 &= 0, \\ \delta \cdot 341 + \alpha \cdot 312 + \beta \cdot 323 &= 0, \\ \alpha \cdot 412 + \beta \cdot 423 + \gamma \cdot 434 &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\begin{aligned} \beta \cdot 123 + \gamma \cdot 134 + \delta \cdot 141 &= 0, \\ \gamma \cdot 234 + \delta \cdot 241 + \alpha \cdot 212 &= 0, \\ \delta \cdot 341 + \alpha \cdot 312 + \beta \cdot 323 &= 0, \\ \alpha \cdot 412 + \beta \cdot 423 + \gamma \cdot 434 &= 0. \end{aligned}$$

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and these are at once seen to give

$$\alpha : \beta : \gamma : \delta = 234 : 341 : 412 : 123 = -341 : 412 : -123 : 234,$$

so that, the required identical relation is

$$234 \cdot 012 - 341 \cdot 023 + 412 \cdot 034 - 123 \cdot 041 = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$PAB \cdot BCD - PBC \cdot CDA + PCD \cdot DAB - PDA \cdot ABC = 0,$$

which signifies that this signs being attended to the signs of the triangles PAB , PCD , PDA , BCD , CDA , DAB , ABC , are taken with respect to the hexagon of the point.

4. Find at any point of a plane curve the angle between the normal and the line drawn from the point to the centre of any one of the two circles of curvature.

Excursus whether a like question applies to a point on a surface and the indicatrix section at such point.

Taking the origin at the point on the curve, and considering as the axis of x the tangent and that of y with the normal, the equation of the curve is

$$y = bx^2 + cx^3 + \dots,$$

and if, considering x as small quantity of the first order, and therefore y as a small quantity of the second order, we regard y as given, and find the two values x_1 , x_2 such of the order $\sqrt{y}$, which satisfy the equation, then, as will appear, $x_1 + x_2$, is a small quantity of the order $\sqrt{y}$, and consequently $\frac{1}{2}(x_1 + x_2)$ is of the order y , that is if ϕ be the required angle, then obviously $\tan \phi = \frac{1}{2y}(x_1 + x_2)$.

Taking the origin at the point on the curve, the original equation is the usual approximation $bx^2 = y$, $cx^3 = y(1 - \frac{x}{b})$, whence $x = \sqrt{\frac{y}{b}}(1 - \frac{c}{2b}\frac{x}{b})$, $cx^3 = \frac{1}{2}y$, &c., so we have

$$x_1 = \sqrt{\frac{y}{b}} - \frac{cy}{2b^2},$$

$$x_2 = -\sqrt{\frac{y}{b}} - \frac{cy}{2b^2},$$

and thence

$$\frac{1}{2}(x_1 + x_2) = -\frac{cy}{2b^2},$$

which gives the value of the angle, viz. obviously $\tan \phi = -\frac{c}{b^2}$; which gives the value of the angle ϕ ; it would be easy to express b , c in terms of the differential coefficients

$$\frac{dx}{dy}, \frac{d^2y}{dx^2}, \frac{d^3y}{dx^3}.$$

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It would at first sight appear that a like question might be asked as to a surface; viz. that it might be proposed to determine the angle between the normal and a line drawn from the point to the centre of the indicatrix conic. But this is not so; in fact, taking the origin at a point on the surface, the axis of z being in the tangent plane, and that of z coinciding with the normal; then for the third order we have

$$z = (A, B, C\check{a}x, y)^2 + (a, b, c, d\check{a}x, y)^3;$$

but here, regarding z as a given constant, if we take account of the terms of the third order, the section is not a conic but a cubic; and it has not in general any centre; and if (as in the ordinary theory) we neglect the terms of the third order, thus obtaining an indicatrix conic, the centre of this conic lies on the normal, and there is no angle corresponding to the angle ϕ of the plane problem.

The only case where there is no objection is when the cubic terms $(a, b, c, d\check{a}x, y)^3$ contain as a factor the quadric terms $(A, B, C\check{a}x, y)^2$ (one relation between the coefficients a, b, c, d of the cubic function depending on this relation), and in such case the indicatrix section corresponds to the surface plane $z =$ (a coincident section: in this case may be defined as a section by a plane parallel to the tangent plane, but at any rate close to it as a coincident plane. To complete the analogy, (2) the two functions depend in any manner whatever on one and the same set of constants.

5. If V, V' are binary functions of the form $(\alpha, b, \dots \check{a}x, 1)^n$ with arbitrary coefficients, and if the equation $U = 0, V = 0$ have a common root, show how this can be determined in terms of the derived functions of the Resultant in regard to the coefficients of either function.

Show what results in regard to the common root can be obtained when the coefficients are not all of them arbitrary but (1) each or either of the functions depends in any manner whatever on a set of arbitrary coefficients not entering into the other function, (2) the two functions depend in any manner whatever on one and the same set of arbitrary coefficients.

Here is the theory analytical at once, instead of the two equations, there is a single equation $U = 0$ having a double root.

Suppose

$$U = (a, b, \dots \check{a}x, 1)^m, \quad \left(= ax^m + \frac{m}{1}bx^{m-1} + \&c. \right),$$

$$V = (a, b, \dots \check{a}x, 1)^n, \quad \left(= ax^n + \frac{n}{1}bx^{n-1} + \&c. \right).$$

Then if R is the resultant, the equation $R = 0$ is the relation which must exist between the coefficients in order that the two functions U and V shall have a common root. Moreover, if we assume that U and V may have a common root $x = \alpha$, then we have $U_\alpha = 0, V_\alpha = 0$; the coefficients of U_α, V_α being the same as those of U, V , and $x = \alpha$. We have then identically $U_\alpha = 0, V_\alpha = 0, R = 0$; that is, these equations have to be infinitesimally varied in such manner that U, V have still a common root $x = \alpha$, we have the equation $U = 0, V = 0$ subsist when $a, b, \dots$, the coefficients of U , and $a, b, \dots$ those of V undergoes, the given relation must be a common root, a this implies between $U_\alpha, V_\alpha, R_\alpha$ &c.

$$da \frac{dR}{da} + db \frac{dR}{db} + \&c. = 0.$$

But the common factor $x = \alpha y$ is a factor of the unaltered equation $U = 0$, and the values of (x, y) are thus unaltered, viz. the equation $U = 0$ is satisfied with the original values of (x, y) ; that is, changing the α as a small quantity of the first order, we have

$$x^m da + mx^{m-1}y db + \&c. = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$x^m \sigma + mx^{m-1} y \sigma' + \&c. = 0$$

an equation which must agree with the former one, that is, we have

$$x^m : mx^{m-1} y : \dots = \frac{dR}{da} : \frac{dR}{db} : \dots,$$

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5. Show that a cubic surface has at most four conic points; and a quartic surface at most sixteen conical points.

If a cubic surface has two conical points, then the line joining these has with the surface two intersections at each of the conical points, and therefore lies wholly in the surface. Hence, for a cubic surface with three conical points A, B, C , the lines AB, BC, CA lie wholly in the surface, and three more lines, viz. ones formed by the lines through three conical points A, B, C, D ; the line AB , &c. wholly in the surface, and these lines form among them the complete section of the surface by a plane wholly through the conic; this is the case of complete section of the surface, and the cubic surface is in fact equal to the cubic surface as is well known the cubic surface contains four points E , and the line joining E with any of the four conical points has, by the line, three points of contact with the surface, and is therefore not a tangent line. Hence the section of a cubic surface by a plane through three conical points A, B, C , would be the triangle ABC taken twice, and a line which is the locus of points E ; but each of the points E, E_1 in particular, would have to be conical points, and the cubic surface would have 5, that is, more than four conical points, which is impossible.

6. Find the differential equation of the parallel surfaces of an ellipsoid.

Let (x, y, z) be the coordinates of a point on the ellipsoid $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} + \frac{z^2}{c^2} - 1 = 0$; (X, Y, Z) the coordinates of a point on the normal at a distance $= k$ from the foot-mentioned point. We have

$$\frac{X-x}{\frac{x}{a^2}} = \frac{Y-y}{\frac{y}{b^2}} = \frac{Z-z}{\frac{z}{c^2}} = \mu \quad \text{suppose;}$$

that is,

$$X = x \left(1 + \frac{\mu}{a^2}\right), \quad Y = y \left(1 + \frac{\mu}{b^2}\right), \quad Z = z \left(1 + \frac{\mu}{c^2}\right);$$

and thence

$$k^2 = \mu^2 \left\{ \frac{x^2}{a^4} + \frac{y^2}{b^4} + \frac{z^2}{c^4} \right\}.$$

Moreover

$$\frac{X^2}{(a^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{Y^2}{(b^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{Z^2}{(c^2 + \mu)^2} = \frac{x^2}{a^4} + \frac{y^2}{b^4} + \frac{z^2}{c^4};$$

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substituting these values in the equation of the ellipsoid, we have

$$1 = \frac{a^2 X^2}{(a^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{b^2 Y^2}{(b^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{c^2 Z^2}{(c^2 + \mu)^2},$$

which determines μ as a function of X, Y, Z . The tangent plane of the ellipsoid at the point (x, y, z) and of the parallel surface at the point (X, Y, Z) are parallel to each other (for what is the same thing, the parallel surface cuts at right angles on the normal of the ellipsoid); we have therefore

$$\frac{X}{a^2} dX + \frac{Y}{b^2} dY + \frac{Z}{c^2} dZ = 0,$$

or substituting for x, y, z their values, we have

$$\frac{X dX}{a^2 + \mu} + \frac{Y dY}{b^2 + \mu} + \frac{Z dZ}{c^2 + \mu} = 0,$$

where μ denotes as above a function of (X, Y, Z) given by the equation

$$1 = \frac{a^2 X^2}{(a^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{b^2 Y^2}{(b^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{c^2 Z^2}{(c^2 + \mu)^2}.$$

We have thus the differential equation of the parallel surface. It may be remarked, that the integral equation (involving k as the constant of integration), is found by the elimination of μ, x, y, z from the foregoing equations

$$X - x = \mu \frac{x}{a^2}, \quad Y - y = \mu \frac{y}{b^2}, \quad Z - z = \mu \frac{z}{c^2},$$

or, what is the same thing, by the elimination of μ from the equations

$$\frac{X^2}{(a^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{Y^2}{(b^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{Z^2}{(c^2 + \mu)^2} = \frac{1}{\mu^2} k^2,$$

$$\frac{a^2 X^2}{(a^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{b^2 Y^2}{(b^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{c^2 Z^2}{(c^2 + \mu)^2} = 1;$$

these may be replaced by

$$\frac{X^2}{(a^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{Y^2}{(b^2 + \mu)^2} + \frac{Z^2}{(c^2 + \mu)^2} = \frac{k^2}{\mu^2},$$

$$\frac{X^2}{a^2 + \mu} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \mu} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \mu} - 1 = 0,$$

or, since here the second equation is the derived equation of the first in regard to the parameter μ , the parallel surface is the envelope of the quadric surface

$$p(\mu) + p'(\mu) + p''(\mu) - 1 = 0, \quad p(\mu) = \frac{X^2}{a^2 + \mu} + \frac{Y^2}{b^2 + \mu} + \frac{Z^2}{c^2 + \mu}.$$

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7. *Explain wherein consists the peculiarity of the following problem, and solve it by geometrical considerations:—*

Determine the knot circle inclosing three given points.

The peculiarity of the problem is that the variable parameters upon which the circle depends, viz. a, β the coordinates of the centre and ρ its radius, are not all subject to any equations, but only to the inequalities

$$b^2 + (a - x_1)^2 \leq \rho^2, \quad b^2 + (a - x_2)^2 \leq \rho^2, \quad b^2 + (a - x_3)^2 \leq \rho^2,$$

$(\alpha_1, \beta_1), (\alpha_2, \beta_2), (\alpha_3, \beta_3)$, the coordinates of the given points, and the $\leq$ indicates that the points are within or on the circumference of the circle, and the equation $\rho =$ minimum. The parallel surface inclosing within or on the circumference of the circle, and the points A, B, C separately. Then for the values of a, β , the second sides of the (a, β, ρ) the variables of the given points, with the condition that the points A, B, C are within or on the circumference; and then ρ minimum.

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But if a be the acoustic anomaly, then

$$x = a \sin u, \quad y = b \sin u, \quad a = \sqrt{1 - e^2} \sin u,$$

and the equations become

$$\begin{aligned} -\sin u \frac{d^2 u}{dt^2} + \cos u \left(\frac{du}{dt} \right)^2 - \frac{\sin u}{a^2} + \frac{\cos u}{a^2(1 - e \sin u)^2} \cos u &= 0, \\ +\cos u \frac{d^2 u}{dt^2} + \sin u \left(\frac{du}{dt} \right)^2 - \frac{\cos u}{a^2(1 - e \sin u)^2} \sin u &= 0, \end{aligned}$$

and multiplying by $-\cos u$, $-\sin u$, respectively, and adding, we have

$$\left(\frac{du}{dt} \right)^2 = \frac{1}{a^2(1 - e \sin u)^2 - e^2 a^2 \sin^2 u} \cdot \frac{1}{1 + e \sin u},$$

which is the required differential equation.

9. Show that the attraction of an indefinitely thin double-convex lens at a point at the centre of one of its faces is equal to that of the infinite plate included between the tangent plane at the point and the parallel tangent plane of the other face of the lens.

The figure represents the upper half only of the lens, but in speaking of any portion thereof, such as PRQ , we include the symmetrically situate portion of the under-half of the lens.

Let a , $= PQ$, be the thickness of the lens, LPQ a circle of which angle is ultimately $= \frac{a}{a}$. Then it is at once seen that the attraction of the cone LPQ is $= \text{const} = 2\pi a$; and from this it follows that the attraction of the infinite plate is $= 2\pi a$. The attraction of the whole infinite plane (resp. the cone LPQ) is $= 2\pi a$, which is indefinitely small in regard to $2\pi a$; and, *a fortiori*, the attraction of the portion MPR of the lens is indefinitely small in regard to $2\pi a$. We have then only to show that the attraction of the mass LRQ is indefinitely small in regard to $2\pi a$; the mass being, in fact, indefinitely thin in the direction of the lens, the attraction of the cone MRQ will not therefore ultimately be $= 2\pi a$.

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Let the position of an element of the solid in question be determined by r the distance from P , θ the inclination of r to the axis PQ and ϕ the azimuth in regard to any fixed plane through the axis; then $dm = r^2 \sin \theta dr d\theta d\phi$, the integral in regard to ϕ having been taken from 0 to 2π , and the attraction in the direction in the figure: PQ is $= \iint a \sin \theta \cos \theta dr d\theta - \frac{1}{2} \iint \sin 2\theta dr d\theta$, the integral in regard to ϕ having been taken from 0 to π ; and the attraction in the direction of PQ from any point $A = a$ constant when $\phi = ar$, and that for $\phi = a$, the limit is the small circle. The plane PRQ , ($Z = 0$) the equation will be $\phi = \text{const.}$

Taking the radius of the small circle to be $= \rho$, then for a fixed value of ϕ the value of r extends from 0 to $\frac{2\rho \cos \theta}{1 - e \sin \theta}$, while the integral in regard to ϕ is to be taken from $\phi = 0$ for the value of r for which $\theta = \tan^{-1} \frac{a}{\rho}$ to $\phi = \frac{\pi}{2}$. We have then

$$\frac{1}{2}a^2 \int \sin 2\theta d\phi = (1 + e) \sin \theta \cos \theta (1 + e^2 \sin^2 \theta) d\theta,$$

and the integral is to be taken from $\theta = 0$ to $\theta = \tan^{-1} \frac{a}{\rho}$, viz. this is

$$\int \sin \theta \cos \theta (1 - e \sin \theta)^2 (1 + e^2 \sin^2 \theta)^{-1} d\theta - a a^2 a^{-2} d\theta,$$

so that taking this between the limits in question, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{1}{2}a^2 \int \sin 2\theta d\phi &= (1 + e) \sin^2 \theta - \frac{1}{6}(1 + e)^2(1 - e \sin \theta)^3 \\ &\quad - (1 + e) \frac{1}{4} \left[1 - \frac{1}{(1 + e)^2} \right] - \frac{1}{2}(1 + e^2) \left[1 - \frac{1}{1 + e} \right] \\ &\quad + \frac{1}{2}(1 - 2e^2) \frac{(1 + e)^2 + (1 + e)}{1 + e} - \frac{1}{3}(1 - 2e^2) \frac{(1 + e)^3 + 1}{(1 + e)^3}. \end{aligned}$$

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viz. a here an indefinitely small quantity of the order a^2 ; all the terms are therefore at least of the order a^2 , and are to be neglected in comparison with $2\pi a$, the integral work shown we have $A = 0$ (that is, the attraction of the mass LRQ is indefinitely small in the standard sense (since $L = a$ to the doctrine in the form RPQ is mass equal in $2\pi a$), as the theorem is thus proved.

10. *Indicate in what manner the Lagrangian equations of motion*

$$\frac{d}{dt} \frac{dT}{dx'} - \frac{dT}{dx} + \frac{dV}{dx} = 0, \quad \&c.$$

lead to the equation

$$\frac{d^2x}{dt^2} + (U - R) \frac{dV}{dy} = 0, \quad \&c.$$

for the motion of a solid body about a fixed point.

The expression of the vis viva theorem T is

$$T = \frac{1}{2}(Ap^2 + Bq^2 + Cr^2);$$

but this expression will not by itself lead to the equations of motion; we require to know also the expression of p, q, r in terms of certain coordinates λ, μ, ν , which determine the position of body in regard to axes fixed in space, and of the differential coefficients λ', μ', ν' of these coordinates in regard to the time; each of the quantities p, q, r will be a linear function of λ', μ', ν' , ($p = a\lambda' + b\mu' + c\nu', \&c.$), containing in any manner whatever the coordinates λ, μ, ν , and the equations of motion will be

$$A \frac{dp}{dt} \frac{dq}{d\lambda} + B \frac{dq}{dt} \frac{dr}{d\mu} + C \frac{dr}{dt} \frac{dp}{d\nu} = 0, \quad \&c.$$

where $\frac{dp}{d\lambda}, \frac{dq}{d\mu}, \frac{dr}{d\nu}$ are each independent of λ', μ', ν' ; hence, in the equation, the only terms containing the differential coefficients of λ', μ', ν' are the terms

$$A \frac{dp}{dt} \frac{dq}{d\lambda'} + B \frac{dq}{dt} \frac{dr}{d\mu'} + C \frac{dr}{dt} \frac{dp}{d\nu'};$$

of $\frac{dT}{dx'} - \frac{dT}{dx}$; and hence, assuming that the equations of motion on the known equations $A \frac{dp}{dt} + (C - B)qr = 0$, it appears that the equation $A \frac{d^2x}{dt^2} + (U - R) \frac{dV}{dx} = 0$ may be put

$$\frac{d}{dt} \left[A \frac{dp}{dt} \cdot \frac{dq}{d\lambda'} + B \frac{dq}{dt} \cdot \frac{dr}{d\mu'} + (C - B)qr \frac{dp}{d\nu'} \right] = 0;$$

$$\frac{d}{dt} \left[A \frac{dp}{dt} \cdot \frac{dq}{d\mu'} + B \frac{dq}{dt} \cdot \frac{dr}{d\nu'} + (A - C)rp \frac{dq}{d\lambda'} \right] = 0;$$

$$\frac{d}{dt} \left[A \frac{dp}{dt} \cdot \frac{dq}{d\nu'} + B \frac{dq}{dt} \cdot \frac{dr}{d\lambda'} + (B - A)pq \frac{dr}{d\mu'} \right] = 0;$$

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$\frac{dp}{d\lambda'}, \frac{dq}{d\mu'}, \frac{dr}{d\nu'}, \&c.$ in not = 0; and the three equations are therefore equivalent to (as they should be) to the equations

$$A \frac{dp}{dt} + (C - B)qr = 0, \quad \&c.$$

What precedes is a complete answer to the question, but in regard to the actual expression of p, q, r , it may be remarked, that these quantities may be expressed very symmetrically in terms of the quantities

$$\lambda, \mu, \nu = \tan \frac{1}{2}\theta \cos \phi, \tan \frac{1}{2}\theta \sin \phi, \tan \frac{1}{2}\theta,$$

which determine the position of the principal axes in regard to the axes fixed in space, by means of the angles of position (azim. ϕ and the resultant axis, and the notation of about this axis is θ ; writing $a^2 + b^2 + c^2 = k^2$, we have, the equations

$$ap = (1 + b^2)\lambda' - (1 + c^2)\mu' + (\nu - h)\nu',$$

$$aq = (b + c)\lambda' - h^2\mu' - (\mu + g)\nu',$$

$$ar = (n - g)\lambda' + h\mu' + h^2\nu';$$

and the above result may be verified *a posteriori* without any difficulty. See Crelle's *Math. Jour.*, vol. XI. (1843), [6], p. 224, [Coll. Math. Papers, vol. I. p. 33].

11. Find in the Hamiltonian form,

$$\frac{dx}{dt} = \frac{dH}{dp}, \quad \frac{dp}{dt} = -\frac{dH}{dx}, \quad \&c.$$

the equations for the motion of a particle acted on by a central force.

Taking as coordinates r the radius vector, ω the longitude, y the latitude, the equation of the vis viva function is

$$T = \frac{1}{2}(r'^2 + r^2 \cos^2 y \omega'^2 + r^2 y'^2),$$

hence

$$\frac{dT}{dr'} = r' = a \quad \text{suppose,}$$

$$\frac{dT}{d\omega'} = r^2 \cos^2 y \omega' = \nu \quad ,$$

$$\frac{dT}{dy'} = r^2 y' = \mu \quad ,$$

and the expression of T in terms of r, a, y and the new coordinates a, ν, μ is

$$T = \frac{1}{2} \left(a^2 + \frac{\mu^2}{r^2} + \frac{\nu^2}{r^2 \cos^2 y} \right);$$

whence writing

$$H = \frac{1}{2} \left(a^2 + \frac{\mu^2}{r^2} + \frac{\nu^2}{r^2 \cos^2 y} \right) + V,$$

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the equations are

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dH}{dr} &= a, & \frac{dH}{d\omega} &= \nu, & \frac{dH}{dy} &= \mu, \\ -\frac{dH}{dr} &= a, & -\frac{dH}{d\omega} &= \nu, & -\frac{dH}{dy} &= \mu. \end{aligned}$$

We have

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dH}{dr} &= -\frac{\nu^2}{r^3} - \frac{\mu^2}{r^3 \cos^2 y} + \frac{dV}{dr}, \\ \frac{dH}{dy} &= \frac{\mu^2}{r^2 \cos^2 y} \tan y + \frac{dV}{dy} \quad \frac{dH}{d\omega} = \frac{dV}{d\omega} = \frac{r^2 \cos^2 y \omega'}{r^2 \cos^2 y}; \end{aligned}$$

and substituting these values, the equations of motion present themselves in a system of the first order between r , a , y , μ , ν , and it is well known that the case of a central force corresponds to that of a function V where the function V contains r only.

12. *An ordered polygon of $(n+1)$ vertices is constructed as follows:— viz. the several vertices are taken at random of the unknown a . In each, considering as the largest order a the size of the whole polygon is very small; and may be regarded as being $= 1$, and the area between the ordinates corresponding to the several values of being $= 1$, are like ordinate. Find the probability of the unknown polygon being in the form of a convex polygon, and the corresponding probabilities respective ordinate.*

It is somewhat more convenient to take account also of the abscissa $= 1, \dots = u$, thereby obtaining a polygon of $2n+1$ vertices, corresponding to the abscissa 1 , in the largest, and the position of the polygon being on either side of the abscissa $= 1$, that is, the polygon is fixed at the abscissa $= a$, ever this, a being any given number, the probability of a number of heads between $n = a$ and $a + a$ increases with the number a being fixed and equally probable, all the probability of the form in question being so probably, and so on; the probability of the position of these large numbers of vertices: viz. the chance that the polygon has only a number of vertices equal to that of the first a of the second period, that is, the probability of a vertex polygon between the ABC , hence the two periods have its sum.

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The conclusion in regard to the areas of the polygons is that, taking A any given value whatever, however large, the ratio (so being of course $> A$) which the area between the ordinates of the abscissa $a+1, \dots = a+n$ bears to the area of the whole polygon (or to unity) continually decreases as n increases, and ultimately vanishes; but contrariwise, taking a way given function whatever, however small, the area which the respectively bears to the area of the whole polygon, however small, becomes ultimately $= 1$.

13. *Show that for the quartic surface $aU^2 + 2bUV + cV^2 + 2dW + e = 0$, where of the surface is a quartic surface through six points particular values (U, V, W , &c.); then the equation of the general quartic surface through the six points will be of the form*

$$(U \cdot V, W, \cdot) \cdot \alpha U + \beta V + \gamma W + \dots = 0,$$

($U, V, W, \cdot$) the coordinates of the vertex, in regard to the unknown.

Suppose $U = 0, V = 0, W = 0$ are particular line quadric surfaces through the six points then the equation of the general quartic surface through the six points will be of the form

$$aU^2 + 2bUV + cV^2 + 2dW + e = 0;$$

where (a, b, c, d, e) are constants. In order to that there is a node we must have for the coordinates of the vertex, the equations combined with the given equation

$$a \frac{dU}{dx} + b \frac{dV}{dx} + b \frac{dW}{dx} + d \frac{dT}{dx} = 0,$$

$$a \frac{dU}{dy} + b \frac{dV}{dy} + c \frac{dW}{dy} + d \frac{dT}{dy} = 0,$$

$$a \frac{dU}{dz} + b \frac{dV}{dz} + c \frac{dW}{dz} + d \frac{dT}{dz} = 0,$$

$$a \frac{dU}{dw} + b \frac{dV}{dw} + c \frac{dW}{dw} + d \frac{dT}{dw} = 0.$$

Eliminating (a, b, c, d) , we have an equation $\nabla = 0$, where ∇ is the Jacobian or fractional determinant $\frac{d(U, V, W, T)}{d(x, y, z, w)}$ formed with the differential coefficients of the four functions (U, V, W, Z); the locus of the vertex is then a quartic surface.

Calling the six points 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6, then taking as vertex any point in the line 12, the lines from such point to the points 1 and 2 coincide with the line 12, and we can through this line and the lines to the remaining points 3, 4, 5, 6 describe a quadric cone; the quartic surface therefore passes through the line 12; and similarly it passes through each of the fifteen lines 12, 13, ..., 56.

Again, taking the vertex anywhere in the line of intersection of the planes 123 and 456, we have an improper quadric cone, viz. the plane-pair formed by these two

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planes; the line in question is therefore a line of the quartic surface, and similarly the quartic surface contains all the two lines 123, 456; 124, 356; 134, 456. We have thus in all 25 lines on the quartic.

In the case of seven points 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6, 7, the locus is the curve of intersection of the quartic surfaces (obtained through any one of the six points 1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6; 23, 24, 25, 26, 34, 45 to which it should be $= 16$, $b = 71$, $c = 56$). Here the several lines on either of the surfaces, viz. part of the curve in question are: viz. on or scarce curve, which is the locus of the vertices of the cones which pass through the seven given points.

14. *Show that the envelope of a system of circles having its centre on a given and cutting at right angles a given circle is a bicircular quartic; which, when the plane which and circles has double contact, becomes a pair of circles; and, by considering the magnitude of the latter, deduce, the area of curve in regard between the two principal planes.*

(1) *given two circles, to find a polygon of n sides inscribed in the one and circumscribed about the other.*

The equation of the given circle is taken to be

$$(x - a)^2 + (y - \beta)^2 = a^2,$$

and that of the conic $\frac{x^2}{a^2} + \frac{y^2}{b^2} = 1$. This being so, we have $a \cos \theta$, $b \sin \theta$ as the coordinates of a point on the conic, which point may be taken to be the centre of the variable circle, and introducing the condition that the two circles cut at right angles, the equation of the variable circle is

$$(x - a \cos \theta)^2 + (y - b \sin \theta)^2 = a^2 \cos^2 \theta + b^2 \sin^2 \theta + c^2,$$

that is,

$$x^2 + y^2 - a^2 - 2xa \cos \theta - 2yb \sin \theta + b^2 \sin^2 \theta - 2yb \sin \theta = 0,$$

where θ is the variable parameter; and the equation of the envelope therefore is

$$(x^2 + y^2 - c^2) \cos^2 \theta + (a^2 - b^2) \sin \theta \cos \theta - 2ax \cos \theta - 2by \sin \theta + b^2 = 0,$$

which is a quartic, having and belonging to each as b , c , in the same equation as would have been obtained from either of the other conics and the corresponding circle, and from the form of the equation it is clear that the curve is a bicircular quartic.

If the fixed circle touches the conic, then by a consideration of the figure it at once appears that the point of contact is a double point on the curve; and as if there is a double contact, then each of the points of contact is a double point on the curve. But in this case the curve is a bicircular quartic with four double points, viz. it is a pair of circles.

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The points in regard to the two conics is that, in general it is not possible to find any polygon of n sides satisfying the conditions; but that the case is also such that there exists an infinity of polygons; viz. any point whatever of the one conic may then be taken as a vertex of the polygon, and there are corresponding the the $(n+1)^{\text{th}}$ vertex still coincide with the first vertex, and there will be a polygon of n sides.

Now imagine that the conic touched by the sides is a circle having double contact with the other conic. Describe any one of the polygons, and with each vertex as centre describe the orthotomic circle, which will, it is clear, be a circle passing through the points of contact with the circles, each touching the two adjacent circles of the series. And by considering any other polygon, we have a like series of a circles; and by what precedes the envelope of all the circles of the several series is a pair of circles; that is, the circles of every series touch these two circles. We have consequently two circles, such that there exists an infinity of closed series of n circles, each circle touching the two fixed circles, and also the two adjacent circles of the series; which is the porism arising out of the second problem.

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Note on the Problem of Envelopes.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. I. (1872), pp. 3, 4.]*

THERE is a mode of looking at the problem of Envelopes, which, so far as I am aware, has not been explicitly noticed. Let $U = (x, y, z)^m$ be a function of the coordinates (x, y, z) ($\Theta = 0$ or (x, y, z) of θ , a function of the new set of coordinates (x, y, z) and (x', y', z') , θ being understood that when we write $\Theta = 0$ this expresses the existence of a relation between the coordinates (x, y, z) and the new set of coordinates (x', y', z') . Suppose that we have $\Theta = 0$, $U = 0$; that is, then the equation expresses θ as a function of (x, y, z) , (x', y', z') ; this is then a curve: the equation expressed values of parameters in coordinates (x, y, z) of a point P on the curve $U = 0$; and we may say that θ is the envelope (equivalent to four equations only)

$$U = 0, \quad \Theta = 0,$$

$$d_x U + \lambda d_x \Theta = 0, \quad d_y U + \lambda d_y \Theta = 0, \quad d_z U + \lambda d_z \Theta = 0,$$

and a particular integral $ay - b = 0$: the complete integral is in fact

$$(x - cy)^2 - 4r^2b^2 + 2(p - q)y^2 - rp^2 = 0,$$

satisfied, for $C = 0$, by $xy - n = 0$.

But, observe that the required envelope is the locus of the points of intersection of the curve $U = 0$, by curves in a particular point (x', y', z') of the other curve, $\Theta = 0$. So the curve $U = 0$ which belongs to a consecutive point (x', y', z') of the curve $U = 0$, considering therein (x', y', z') as the variable; by such a process the envelope of the curve y in question is a mere definition of what it does mean, and comes to be a fluxion. y then only chosen the values of A are $b, b', b'', \&c.$, and these values are then determined by the equations:— viz. if P is a point on the conic (x', y', z') , then conics, conditions (x', y', z') are conics on the same conic (x', y', z') as their values: and the curve in the plane which corresponds spend to the generating loop of the model.

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$\Theta = 0$, $U = 0$ to touch each other, we have a relation in (x', y', z') which is the equation of the point intersection of the curves $\Theta = 0$ belonging to the two consecutive values of the curve $U = 0$; that is, the equation of the required envelope is obtained as the condition that the curves $U = 0$, $\Theta = 0$ shall touch each other. But when the curves touch each, they have at the point of contact two consecutive points proportional, or we have simultaneously

$$U = 0, \quad \Theta = 0,$$

$$d_x U + \lambda d_x \Theta = 0,$$

$$d_y U + \lambda d_y \Theta = 0,$$

$$d_z U + \lambda d_z \Theta = 0,$$

the same equations as before, since $\Theta = 0$ and $\Theta = 0$ are the same function.

It is to be added that, when $a = u$, the equations

$$d_x U + \lambda d_x \Theta = 0,$$

$$d_y U + \lambda d_y \Theta = 0,$$

$$d_z U + \lambda d_z \Theta = 0,$$

are homogeneous in (x, y, z) , and we may by the elimination of (x, y, z) from these equations obtain an equation $\text{Disc. } (U \pm \lambda U) = 0$, say for shortness $\Delta = 0$, involving λ and also the coordinates (x', y', z') . Now it is a known theorem that the condition for the contact of the two curves $U = 0$, $U = 0$ may be obtained by expressing that the equation $\Delta = 0$ shall have a pair of equal roots, or, what is the same thing, by equating to the equation of the envelope of the curve $U = 0$, viz. by being so as shown the equation of the envelope of the curves $U = 0$, is in fact

$$\text{Disc. } \text{Disc.}_{(\lambda, 1)}(U + \lambda U) = 0;$$

viz. we first take the discriminant of the function $\Theta + \lambda U$ in regard to the coordinates (x, y, z) and then taking the discriminant in regard to λ of the function so obtained, b is zero. This is in many cases a more simple process than that of the direct elimination of x, y, z, λ from the equations.

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Note on Lagrange's Demonstration of Taylor's Theorem.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. 1. (1872), pp. 22-24.]*

I TAKE the occasion of the publication of the last edition of Mr Todhunter's *Treatise on the Differential Calculus* to make some remarks on the demonstration in question. Mr Todhunter proposes to himself to establish a comprehensive view of the *Differential Calculus* as the method of Limits; but he very properly introduces in some cases demonstration founded upon other views of the subject, pointing out that this is the case, and explaining or justifying his objections. Thus (Chapter VI.) upon Taylor's Theorem, he remarks: "Before we offer a strict demonstration of the theorem in question, we shall notice the method which it was usual to adopt in treatises on the Differential Calculus not based on the doctrine of limits;" and then, after giving a demonstration depending on the relation $\frac{d}{dx}f(x+h) = \frac{d}{dh}f(x+h)$ he goes on to say "There are numerous objections to the method of the preceding article, and especially the use of an infinite series, without ascertaining that it is convergent, is inadmissible; we proceed then to prove Taylor's Theorem after the manner adopted by Mr Homersham Cox(*) in a demonstration of the equation

$$f(x+h) = f(x) + hf'(x) + \cdots + \frac{h^n}{[n+1]^{n+1}} f^{(n+1)}(x+\theta h),$$

(θ between 0 and 1) Taking "if the function $f^{(n)}(x+\theta h)$ is such that by making a sufficiently great the term $\frac{h^n}{[n+1]^{n+1}} f^{(n+1)}(x+\theta h)$ can be made as small as we please, then by carrying on the series

$$f(x) + hf'(x) + \frac{h^2}{2!} f''(x) + \frac{h^3}{3!} f'''(x) + \&c.$$

* This demonstration is similar in principle to Laprange's but I think it is preferable; do, the gives in passing in this rather than the same value whether n is changed once, ; it on it. VIII, p. 9 (1851).

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to as many terms as we please we obtain a result differing as little as we please from $f(x+h)$. Under these circumstances then we may assert the truth of Taylor's theorem."

I share Abel's horror of divergent series(*); and I maintain the validity of Lagrange's demonstration. When by any objection one can expand a function in a series, for instance the function $\frac{1}{1-x}$, by division

$$\frac{1}{1-x} = 1 + x + \frac{x^2}{1-x} = 1 + x + x^2 + \frac{x^3}{1-x}, \&c.$$

$$1 + x + x^2 + x^3 + \&c.,$$

in the series $1 + x + x^2 + \&c.$, and write accordingly

$$\frac{1}{1-x} = 1 + x + x^2 + \&c.$$

all that is for ought be may mean is that the algebraical operations contained as far as we please will give the series of terms $1, x, x^2, \&c.$, or say the series of coefficients $1, 1, 1, \dots$. And of course with this meaning of the equation, the objection "we cannot that the series is convergent" would be wholly irrelevant, we do not say that in is, we do not care whether it is $\&c.$ or not. In further illustration, remark that we frequently use such an equation merely as the means of expressing the law of a series of numbers $a_0, a_1, a_2, \&c., a_n = a + b\theta, \&c.$; we make the assertion to be a definite process expressible in the form $a_n = \text{co. } x^n$ in $a_n = a_0 + a_1x + a_2x^2 + \&c.$ in question. Any objection that the series is not convergent would be simply irrelevant. Now an that the series shall be convergent is wholly employed for the expansion of $f(x+h)$ in regard to $f(x+h)$. It is impossible, in a quantitative algebra such as is presupposed in the method of limits, to put any meaning on the formula

$$f(x+h) = f(x) + hf'(x) + \frac{h^2}{2!}f''(x) + \&c.,$$

viz. $f(x+h)$ requires the same value $f(x+h)$ whether we change therein a into $x+h$ or h into $x+h$; and the expression on the right-hand side is the only series in h possessed of the same property. It is to be remarked that the equation contains in itself the definition of the operation of derivation, viz. the equation being true, $f(x)$ can only denote the coefficient of h in the expansion of $f(x+h)$, and what

* Note on Aragon dans des bons louisges dipres divines.

$$- - - - - - \theta + - (-\theta)^2 + \&c. - - - - -$$

a maint et avait ferois priselt ?—r-, t. iv. p. 263; [Newt. Eli, 1885, t. vii. p. 122].

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really is shown is that admitting such an operation to be possible in regard not only to $f(x)$, but to $f'(x)$, &c., then the coefficients $f'(x)$, $\frac{f''(x)}{2!}$, &c., are obtained from $f(x)$ by the successive repetition of this operation and by dividing by the proper numerical denominator.

By what precedes, any objection in regard to convergency, I regard as irrelevant; and if it is said that the above-mentioned single assumption is not granted, I would either ask “What is a Function?”—or I would contend myself with the hypothetical statement: “If $f(x)$ be such that $f(x+h)$ is expansible in apoly, then Taylor’s theorem.

In regard to the demonstration given by Mr Todhunter, it impliedly assumes that x and h are both real, and (although doubtless possible) it would be considerably more difficult to find an analogous demonstration of the formula involving $f^{(n+1)}(x+\theta h)$ in the case of x and h imaginary. But the formula with the term in question is not (see Mr Todhunter consider it as being) Taylor’s theorem, ; to obtain from it Taylor’s theorem, we require (in the foregoing point of view) the property that $\lim_{n \rightarrow \infty} f^{(n+1)}(x+\theta h)$ is exposible in a series involving h^{n+1} and the higher powers of h , that is, the very property that $f(x+h)$ is exposible in positive powers of h .

Moreover admitting that the formula with the term $f^{(n+1)}(x+\theta h)$ is demonstratable for imaginary values of x , h , then formula is unenchapsie in the case where $x+h$ is one or both a symbol or symbols of operation; whereas it would certainly have to include unmoral magnitude, and if it is considered as meaning anything, then the equation in question is mere definition of what it does mean, and ceases to be a theorem in regard to $f(x+h)$. It is impossible, in a quantitative algebra such as is presupposed in the method of limits, to put any meaning on the formula

$$f\left(\frac{d}{dx} + h\right) = f\left(\frac{d}{dx}\right) + hf'\left(\frac{d}{dx}\right) + \&c.,$$

which however I regard as a legitimate particular form of Taylor’s theorem.

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Solutions of a Smith's Prize Paper for 1871.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. I. (1872), pp. 37-47, 71-77, 89-95.]*

1. *A point moves in a plane with a given velocity, and also with a given angular velocity about a fixed point in the plane: show that the locus is either a circle passing through the fixed point, or else a circle having the fixed point for its centre; and explain the relation between the two solutions.*

We have in general

$$v^2 = \left(\frac{dr}{dt}\right)^2 + r^2 \left(\frac{d\phi}{dt}\right)^2,$$

and in the present question, taking the fixed point as the origin, and measuring θ from any fixed line through this point,

$$\frac{d\theta}{dt} = a, \quad V^2 = \left(\frac{dr}{dt}\right)^2 + r^2 a^2,$$

where V, a are given constants. Hence

$$\left(\frac{dr}{dt}\right)^2 + a^2 r^2 = V^2, \quad \left(\frac{dr}{dt}\right)^2 = V^2 - a^2 r^2,$$

or, writing $V = aa$,

$$\left(\frac{dr}{dt}\right)^2 = a^2(a^2 - r^2);$$

therefore

$$d\theta = \frac{dr}{\sqrt{(a^2 - r^2)}},$$

or

$$\theta + \beta = \sin^{-1} \frac{r}{a}, \quad (\beta \text{ the constant of integration,})$$

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that is,

$$r = a \sin(\theta + \beta),$$

which is the equation of a circle (radius = $\frac{1}{2}a$) passing through the fixed point. In fact, the point moving in such a circle with a constant velocity, moves about the centre with a constant angular velocity; and about any fixed point in the circumference with an angular velocity which is one-half that about the centre, and is therefore also constant.

Treating θ as a variable parameter, to obtain the envelope we have

$$0 = a \cos(\theta + \beta),$$

that is, $\theta + \beta = \frac{\pi}{2}$, and therefore $r = a$, which is the equation of a circle (radius = a) having the fixed point for its centre. This is consequently the singular solution.

2. Determine the system of curves which satisfy the differential equation

$$dx(\sqrt{(1+x^2+xy+xy^2)}) + dy(\sqrt{(1+x^2+xy+xy^2)}) = 0;$$

and that the curve which passes through the point $x = 0, y = 0$, contains as a part of itself the conic

$$x^2 + y^2 + 2xy\sqrt{(1+x^2+xy+xy^2)} = 1.$$

The equation is integrable *per se*, viz. we have

$$x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + \log\{x + \sqrt{(1+x^2)}\} + \frac{1}{2}y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + \log\{y + \sqrt{(1+y^2)}\} = U$$

or, denoting the constant so that the differential equation has its general solution

$$x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + 2xy = (1+x^2+xy+y^2) + \log \frac{\{x + \sqrt{(1+x^2)}\}\{y + \sqrt{(1+y^2)}\}}{1-C} = 0,$$

which is evidently a transcendental curve; it may however be shown that, if

$$x^2 + y^2 + 2xy\sqrt{(1+x^2+xy+xy^2)} - 1 = 0,$$

so that the equation of the curve is then made obvious, that is, the transcendental curve $y = axy + b$, which is the elementary curve, is in this manner included as a part of the curve.

[At a simple illustration as to how this may happen, take the transcendental curve $y = axy + b$, which is the elementary curve, in this manner included as itself.]

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We have, from the equation of the conic

$$\{x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)}\}^2 = (1+x^2)(1-y^2),$$

that is,

$$x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)} = \pm\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1-y^2)},$$

but considering the radicals as positive, the sign must be taken so that we have simultaneously $x + y > 0$, $y = a$. We have therefore

$$x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)} = \sqrt{(1+x^2)(1-y^2)},$$

and similarly

$$y + x\sqrt{(1+y^2)} = \sqrt{(1+y^2)(1-x^2)}.$$

Then

$$\begin{aligned} x\{x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)}\} + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)} &= 2xy + (x^2 + y^2)\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + x\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1-y^2)} \\ &= 2xy + (x^2 + y^2)\sqrt{(1+x^2)} - 2xy(1+x^2) \\ &= xy(1-x^2-y^2) + \sqrt{(1+x^2)}(x^2+y^2) - 2xy(1+x^2) \\ &= xy(1-x^2-y^2) - 2xy(1+x^2), \end{aligned}$$

which is the first of the relations in question; and similarly

$$\begin{aligned} x\{y\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + x\sqrt{(1+y^2)}\} &= \sqrt{(1+y^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)} \\ &= y(1+y^2) - 2y(1-x^2-y^2) \\ &= (1+y^2)\sqrt{(1+x^2)} - 2y(1-x^2-y^2)\sqrt{(1+x^2)} \\ &= -(x+y\sqrt{(1+x^2)})(x+y\sqrt{(1+y^2)}), \end{aligned}$$

which is the second of the two relations. And the theorem is thus proved.

The foregoing is the easiest and most obvious solution, but it is interesting to consider the question differently, as follows:

Write

$$Q = \frac{(x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)})(y + x\sqrt{(1+y^2)})}{x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)}};$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} Q &= (x^2 + y^2 + xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + xy\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}) - A - B, \\ Q^* &= (x^2 + y^2 + 4)(\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + \sqrt{(1+y^2)} + x\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}) = A - B, \end{aligned}$$

if

$$\begin{aligned} A &= x(1+x^2)(1+y^2) + 2xy, \\ B &= x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}, \end{aligned}$$

and then

$$\begin{aligned} AB &= xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + xy\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}, \\ &+ xy(1+y^2)\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + (1+x^2)(1+y^2)\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}, \\ &= xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + xy\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + 2xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}. \end{aligned}$$

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that is,

$$\begin{aligned} Q^2\{2xy + 1 + 2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)}\} - \frac{1}{2}xy\{2xy + 1 + 2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)}\} &= 0, \\ &= 4(x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)}) + 4xy \\ &+ 4xy\{Q\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} - \frac{1}{2}\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}\}; \end{aligned}$$

whence

$$\begin{aligned} 4\{x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + 2xy\} &= Q^2(2xy + 1 + 2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)}) \\ &= Q^2\{2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + 1 + 2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)}\} - \frac{1}{2}xy\{2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + 1 + 2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)}\} \\ &+ 4xy(Q\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} - \frac{1}{2}\sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}) \\ &= (Q-1)(2xy + 1 + 2x\sqrt{(1+x^2)}) \\ &+ 4(Q-1)xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)} \\ &- 4(Q-1)(1+xy^2) \\ &- 4(Q-1)xy^2, \end{aligned}$$

that is,

$$x\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + y\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + 2xy = (Q-1)D.$$

And the integral equation is

$$\frac{1}{2}(Q-1) + \log Q = C,$$

which, for $C = 0$, is satisfied by $Q - 1 = 0$.

Now starting from

$$Q = \frac{(x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)})(y + x\sqrt{(1+y^2)})}{x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)}}$$

we have

$$\sqrt{(1+x^2)} - x = \frac{1}{2}y\{\sqrt{(1+x^2)} - x\} + \frac{1}{2}\{\sqrt{(1+y^2)} - y\},$$

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and thence

$$2x = K\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + Ly,$$

if

$$K = Q\sqrt{(1+x^2)} + x + \frac{1}{2}\sqrt{(1+x^2)-1},$$

$$L = Q\sqrt{(1+y^2)} + y + \frac{1}{2}\sqrt{(1+y^2)-1},$$

whereon

$$L^2 - K^2 = 4.$$

Moreover

$$(2x + Ly)L = K^2 + KLy$$

that is,

$$4x^2 + Ly = K^2 + KLy = K^4,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$x^2 + Lxy = (K - x)^2,$$

which is the rationalized form

$$Q = \frac{x^2 + 2xy\sqrt{(1+x^2+xy+y^2)} - y^2}{xy + \sqrt{(1+x^2)(1+y^2)}} - 1.$$

And if $Q = 1$ then $L = 2\sqrt{(1+x^2)}$, ($L - K^2 = 2x$), and the equation is

$$x^2 + 2xy\sqrt{(1+x^2)} - y^2 = 0,$$

that is, the curve $C = 0$, of the integral integral has, as it should be, a part the conic

$$\frac{x^2 - y^2}{x + y\sqrt{(1+x^2)}} = 1, \quad \text{or as it should be a fixed conic.}$$

We may evidently differently variations, and present the results as follows: the equation

$$\frac{1}{2} \left(\frac{x}{a} + 1 \right) \left(\frac{x}{a} - 1 \right) = \frac{Q+1}{2} \left[\frac{x}{a} + \frac{y-K}{a} \right] - C$$

and a particular integral $xy - n = 0$: the complete integral is in fact

$$(x - cy)^2 - 4r^2e^2 + 2(p - q)y^2 - rp^2 = 0$$

satisfied for $C = 0$, by $xy - n = 0$.

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3. Write $x = b - c$, $\beta = c - a$, $\gamma = a - b$; then considering the three circles and the three conics

$$\begin{aligned}(x - a)^2 + y^2 &= 2bc, & \frac{x^2}{Y^2} + \frac{Y^2}{K + bc} &= 1, \\ (x - b)^2 + y^2 &= -2ac, & \frac{x^2}{K + bc} + \frac{Y^2}{K + ca} &= 1, \\ (x - c)^2 + y^2 &= 2ab, & \frac{x^2}{K + bc} + \frac{Y^2}{K + ab} &= 1.\end{aligned}$$

where K is arbitrary; it is required to show that of a variable circle having its centre in one of the conics cuts at right angles the corresponding circle, the envelope is in each of the three cases one and the same bicircular quartic.

Consider the circle $(x - a)^2 + y^2 = 2bc$ and the conic $\frac{X^2}{Y^2} + \frac{Y^2}{K + bc} = 1$, the coordinates of a point on the conic are $\cos \theta \sqrt{(K)}$, $\sin \theta \sqrt{(K + bc)}$, where θ is a variable parameter; say for a moment these values are p and q . Hence, taking (p, q) as the centre of the variable circle the equation is

$$(x - p)^2 + (y - q)^2 = (p - a)^2 + q^2 - 2bc,$$

and in order that this may cut at right angles the circle

$$(x - a)^2 + y^2 = 2bc,$$

we must have

$$(p - a)^2 + q^2 = 2(p - a)^2 - 2bc + 2bc,$$

or, substituting for p and q their values, the equation of the variable circle is

$$(x - p)^2 + (y - q)^2 = pq^2 + q^2 - 2bp,$$

that is,

$$x^2 + y^2 - p^2 - 2p\sqrt{(K)} - 2q\sqrt{(K + bc)} + 2yp = 0,$$

viz. this is

$$(x^2 + y^2 - p^2)^2 - 2(x + a)\sqrt{(K)} \cos \theta + 2y\sqrt{(K + bc)} \sin \theta + p^2 = 0.$$

Hence taking the envelope in regard to θ , the equation is

$$(x^2 + y^2 - p^2)^2 = 4K(x + a)^2 + 4(K + bc)y^2 - 4y\sqrt{(K + bc)}(x + a) + 4Kp^2,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$[(x + y)^2 - 2a(x + y)\sqrt{(K)} + bc(K + bc)y^2 - 4Ky^2 + 4Kp(2x - bc)] = 0,$$

viz. this equation, being symmetrical in regard to a, b, c , is the same equation as would have been obtained from either of the other conics and the corresponding circle; and from the form of the equation it is clear that the curve is a bicircular quartic.

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4. Show that the caustic by reflexion for parallel rays of a circle, radius r , index of refraction μ , is the same curve as the caustic by refraction for parallel rays of a concentric circle, radius $\frac{r}{\mu}$, index of refraction $\frac{1}{\mu}$.

Take a centre $\mu > 1$. Imagine the ray AP (fig. 1) parallel to the axis of x , incident at P on the circle radius r , and let the reflected ray after cutting the circle, radius $\frac{r}{\mu}$, cut it again at Q , and then cut the axis in R . Take ϕ, ϕ' for the angles of incidence and refraction, viz. $\angle O = \phi$, that is in the manner suitable for the caustic by reflection.

Fig. 1.

Moreover on the triangle PQO , we have $\sin Q : \sin \phi = r : \frac{r}{\mu}$; that is, $\sin Q = \mu \sin \phi$, $= \mu \sin \phi' = \sin \phi'$; or $\angle Q = \phi'$. And then in the triangle RQO , $\angle R = \phi - \phi'$, or $\angle ORQ = 180^\circ - \phi$.

Consider now a ray BQ incident at Q and refracted in the direction QR ; the index of refraction being $\frac{1}{\mu}$, that is, the denser medium being on the outside of small circle. Taking θ, θ' for the angles of incidence and refraction, we have $\theta = \frac{1}{2} \sin^{-1} \phi' = \mu \sin \phi'$ that is, $\theta = \phi$; the angles being two pencils of rays each corresponding to angle BQ of the second pencil, the rays AP and BQ each giving rise to the same refracted ray PQR ; hence the two pencils have the same caustic.

[It is proper to remark that for the ray BQ it has been assumed that the refraction takes place not at Q where it first meets the small circle, but at Q .

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we consider the refraction at Q , then the index of refraction is still to be $= \frac{1}{\mu}$, that is, the denser medium must be inside the small circle: the refracted ray is in the direction RQ situate symmetrically with RQ on the opposite side of the axis of y ; and it would at first sight appear that this would be a curve equal and similar to the original caustic, but situate on the opposite side of the axis of y . But geometrically the complete caustic consists of two equal and similar arches situate on the opposite sides of the axis of y ; so that we really obtain, not an equal portion of the caustic, but the same caustic over again (about the limit changed, viz. as below by (ΔU) . Substitute the variation of U in the symbols of operation differs; the formula is, the variations of Z , then the radii in radii of refraction is still to be $= \frac{1}{\mu}$, that the formula deduced from the variation of Z in so far as it arises from the variation of the constants, viz. the equation $\Delta U = \frac{dU}{d\alpha}d\alpha + d\beta = 0$ remains.

There are the like equations in regard to y, z ; viz. in all, four equations which are linear in regard to $\frac{d\alpha}{d\alpha}, \frac{d\alpha}{d\beta}, \frac{d\alpha}{d\gamma}, \frac{d\alpha}{d\delta}$, and which serve to determine these quantities in terms of $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$.

Now considering the a, y as expressed in terms of $a, c, e, \dots$, then Ω becomes a function of these quantities; the differential coefficients $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}$, &c., being connected with the original differential coefficients $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}, \frac{d\Omega}{d\beta}$, &c. by the equations

$$\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha} = \frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha} \cdot \frac{d\alpha}{d\alpha} + \frac{d\Omega}{d\beta} \cdot \frac{d\beta}{d\alpha}, \quad \&c.$$

As there are four equations, $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}, \frac{d\Omega}{d\beta}$, &c. can be expressed in terms of a, c, e in an infinity of ways in terms of $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}, \frac{d\Omega}{d\beta}$, &c., and, considering $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}$, &c., as given in terms of $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}$, &c., we can in an infinity of ways express $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}$, &c., as linear functions of $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}, \frac{d\Omega}{d\beta}$, &c. But there is no form (obtained by combining the equations in a particular manner) wherein the coefficients of the non-constant quantities are functions of $a, c, e, \dots$ without a contact; and this is the form most simply employed for the expression of $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}$, &c. in terms of $\frac{d\Omega}{d\alpha}, \frac{d\Omega}{d\beta}$, &c. in the method wherein these quantities are made use of in this respect.

I remark upon the present question, that the answer ought to be in evidence perfectly familiar to every student in *Physical Astronomy*; and that a student ought to be able to present it in a clear and lucid form: the question being in fact intended as a test of ability in this respect.

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But in virtue of the relation $a' + \beta' + \gamma' = 1$, we have

$$a \frac{dT}{dx} + \beta \frac{dT}{dy} + \gamma \frac{dT}{dz} = 0,$$

$$a \frac{dy}{dx} + \beta \frac{dy}{dy} + \gamma \frac{dy}{dz} = 0, \quad \&c.$$

Hence subtracting the corresponding equations we have three equations, which are at once seen to be equivalent to the two equations

$$\frac{dT}{dx} d\alpha + \frac{dT}{dy} d\beta + \frac{dT}{dz} d\gamma = 0, \quad \beta : \gamma,$$

equations which must be satisfied identically, whatever are the values of (α, y, z) . The equations have been obtained as necessary conditions; they are, in fact, the sufficient conditions for a double system; for the line being supposed in passing from P to P' , to remain always in contact with the surface, the result is in passing from P to P' , it is necessary that the same line should also be a line of the surface.

6. If particles describe a side of the form $(a, b, \dots \check{a}, x, 1)^n = 0$ with arbitrary coefficients, and if equation $ax^2 + bXy + cy^2 = 0$, where of $(a, b, \dots)$ are arbitrary coefficients respectively in any manner whatever in the function G , then we have a series of equations satisfied by the values x, y which belong to the double root.

The equations

$$aXX + 2bXY + cY^2 + 2(pX + qY) + r = 0$$

$$EX + 2tY + s = 0$$

of common to the two conics, but for this equation to be the case of Z as a W shall vanish, the relation in the points of the plane $\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Y^2}{b} + \frac{Z^2}{c} = 1$; and that X, Y, Z, W are quartic functions of (x, y, z) a common roots, show that this condition of X being equal to V, W , that is, changing the sign in the same way as the linear function of (x, y, z) rationally, and consequently each of the original four roots, may be represented by an equation of the form.

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Taking the conics to pass through the point $a = 0, y = 0$; their equations will be of the form

$$X = ax^2 + 2hxy + by^2 + 2fx + 2gy + qy = 0,$$

$$Y = ax^2 + 2hxy + by^2 + 2fx + 2gy + qy = 0,$$

$$Z = ax^2 + bxy + cy^2 + 2dy + ey^2 + qy = 0,$$

$$W = ax^2 + bxy + cy^2 + 2dy + ey^2 + qy = 0.$$

Now multiplying by the indeterminate quantities $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$; their equations will be of the form. We can determine the values of a, β, γ, δ so that in the sum $\alpha X + \beta Y + \gamma Z + \delta W$ the coefficients of $x, y, 1$ shall vanish, and the term in xy shall, that is, in $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta$, of values of a, β, γ, δ , but as the case may a quartic equation for the values of the ratios; and say $\alpha\beta\gamma\delta : \beta\gamma\delta : \gamma\delta : \delta$ changing the coordinates (x, y) , this remaining equation may be represented by $a^2 = 0$.

And it is clear that we then have, in the system of conics $\alpha X + \beta Y + \gamma Z + \delta W = 0$, four conics the equations of which may be assumed to be of the form

$$X = ax^2 + ax,$$

$$Y = ax^2 + ax,$$

$$Z = ax^2 + ax,$$

$$W = a^2x + ax^2,$$

so that, by writing $a = ax + \dots$, and f, f', f'', f''' are the same conic upon the same linear function of (x, y, z) rationally, and consequently each of the original four roots, may be represented by an equation of the form.

7. *The coordinates (x, y, z) of a point P are given as connected with the coordinates (x', y', z') of a point P' on a plane by equations*

$$x : y : z = a' : Y' : Z' : W';$$

whereof showing, we have

$$ax^2 + y' = 0 :$$

Discuss the connection of P' and P in regard to the equations of points and curves on the two surfaces.

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The equations $x : y : z : w = X' : Y' : Z' : W'$ are two equations establishing indeterminate parameters $x' : y' : z'$, &c. that the eliminating these we have between (x, y, z) a single (homogeneous) equation representing a surface. To each point (x, y, z) a single value $x' : y' : z'$ corresponds and similarly to each point (x', y', z') a single (homogeneous) equation representing a surface. To each point $x' : y' : z' : 1$ which is a corresponding point (x, y, z) on the surface.

To find the order of the surface, consider its intersection with any arbitrary line: $ax + by + cz + dw = 0$,

$$a'x + b'y + c'z + d'w = 0.$$

We have corresponding equations in the plane of intersection of the surface;

$$aX' + bY' + cZ' + dW' = 0,$$

$$a'X' + b'Y' + c'Z' + d'W' = 0;$$

viz. these are two curves: each of them passing through the common point of the four curves, and therefore having common besides these points, three other points: the order of the surface is therefore = 3.

To show that the common point ought to be the (as above) excluded, some further consideration is necessary. To the points of the surface $aX + bY + cZ + dW = 0$ corresponds the locus $aX' + bY' + cZ' + dW' = 0$ and similarly to the points of the linear curve $aX' + bY' + cZ' + dW' = 0$ corresponds the points of the surface $aX + bY + cZ + dW = 0$, then the corresponding loci on the other surface are conics: hence to a similar to the corresponding points of the surface, and which are not common ones (or any belonging to one or more of the conics) the points (x, y, z) , z' which is of the order (α, y) ought to be rejected; the equation in question is thus reduced to $z' = (xz - bX + zZ + xW)xs' + \dots = 0$.

The same result may be obtained and may be further shown that the surface is a a, b, c are the same, the form of the original coordinates (x, y, z) in (x, y, z) to the corresponding points (in the form of the plane $bXy + aX' + aY' + bZW + gZW' = 0$).

In a particular case, the more general assertion of expression of $x' : y' : z'$, in terms of (x, y, z) is to be considered, but every linear function of (x, y, z) rationally, and consequently any sole conic of (x, y, z) rationally; in particular if $x'^2 + y'^2 + z'^2 = 0$, and these equations may be such, are connected by a relation which, in regard to a fixed line, the plane through this line of the plane through the points (x, y, z) and (x, y, z) .

The same may not be obtained, instead of the two equations, that is a single equation $a^2z = 1$, having a double root. The equations are than that the $a^2 + b^2 + c^2 + d^2 + e^2 + 6f^2 + 12g + 4h = 0$.

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are, it is clear, $a = bc - rs$, &c. where a is a variable parameter; and accordingly the place are than as $r =$, $s =$, suppose. With arbitrary parameter; and through the common intersection of the curve $\Omega = 0$.

If f , V , W are binary functions of the form $(\alpha, b, \dots \check{a}, x, 1)^n$ with arbitrary coefficients, and if the equation $U = 0$, $V = 0$ have a common root, show how this can be determined in terms of the derived functions of the Resultant in regard to the coefficients of either function.

Show what results in regard to the common root can be obtained when the coefficients are not all of them arbitrary but (1) each or either of the functions depends in any manner whatever on a set of arbitrary coefficients not entering into the other function, (2) the two functions depend in any manner whatever on one and the same set of arbitrary coefficients.

Suppose

$$U = (a, b, \dots \check{a}, x, 1)^m, \quad \left(= ax^m + \frac{m}{1}bx^{m-1} + \&c. \right),$$

$$V = (a, b, \dots \check{a}, x, 1)^n, \quad \left(= ax^n + \frac{n}{1}bx^{n-1} + \&c. \right).$$

Then if R is the resultant, the equation $R = 0$ is the relation which must exist between the coefficients in order that the two functions U , V may have a common root. Moreover, if we assume that U and V may have a common root $x = \alpha$, then we have $U_\alpha = 0$, $V_\alpha = 0$; the coefficients of U_α , V_α being the same as those of U , V , and $x = \alpha$. We have then identically $U_\alpha = 0$, $V_\alpha = 0$, $R = 0$; that is, these equations have to be infinitesimally varied in such manner that U , V have still a common root $x = \alpha$; we have the equation $U = 0$, $V = 0$ subsist when a , b , $\dots$, the coefficients of U , and the corresponding parameters of V subsist a corresponding equation in the determinations of the roots a , b , c , &c. or some of them.

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There a series of equations giving the value of the common root $\frac{x}{y}(=\alpha)$ in the several ratios

$$\frac{1}{m} : \frac{dR}{da} : \frac{1}{m-1} : \frac{dR}{db} : \frac{1}{m-2} : \frac{dR}{dc} : \frac{1}{1} : \frac{dR}{dk} : \&c.$$

And it is clear that we have in like manner

$$\frac{1}{n} : \frac{dR}{da'} : \frac{1}{n-1} : \frac{dR}{db'} : \&c.$$

It is clear that if U involves, in any manner whatever, the coefficients $a, b, \dots$, which do not enter into the function V , then we have precisely the same expressions as above; and similarly if V involves coefficients which precisely the common root.

A system of equations satisfied by the values x, y which belong to the common root.

But if the coefficients $a, b, \dots$ and $a', b', \&c.$ are contained in any manner whatever in the function U and V respectively, then we are unable to obtain the common root, either as a rational function of the variables, or by aid of these equations.

11. *Find the differential equation $\frac{dV}{dt} = 0$ for the absolute force at, a being the distance of the moving system, on the axes of the moving system.*

Taking as coordinates r the radius vector, ω the longitude, y the latitude, the equation of the vis viva function is

$$T = \frac{1}{2}(r'^2 + r^2 \cos^2 y \omega'^2 + r^2 y'^2),$$

hence

$$\frac{dT}{dr'} = r' = a \quad \text{suppose,}$$

$$\frac{dT}{d\omega'} = r^2 \cos^2 y \omega' = \nu \quad ,$$

$$\frac{dT}{dy'} = r^2 y' = \mu \quad ,$$

and the expression of T in terms of r, a, y and the new coordinates a, ν, μ is

$$T = \frac{1}{2} \left(a^2 + \frac{\mu^2}{r^2} + \frac{\nu^2}{r^2 \cos^2 y} \right);$$

whence writing

$$H = \frac{1}{2} \left(a^2 + \frac{\mu^2}{r^2} + \frac{\nu^2}{r^2 \cos^2 y} \right) + V,$$

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9. *The normal at each point of a principal section of an ellipsoid is intersected by the normal at a consecutive point on the principal section: show that the locus of the point of intersection is an ellipse having four (real or imaginary) common points with the evolute of the principal section.*

The principal section is the convenience taken to be that in the plane of xz , the meridian of the ellipsoid; taking x, z as the coordinates of a point in the plane of xz , and considering the equations of the ellipse; taking a, y, z as the coordinates of a point in the meridian of the ellipsoid; we have for the normal at the point (a, z)

$$\frac{x - x'}{\frac{x'}{a^2}} = \frac{y - y'}{\frac{y'}{b^2}} = \frac{z - z'}{\frac{z'}{c^2}} = -B,$$

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or, substituting for α , the foregoing values,

$$x = x' \left(1 - \frac{B}{a^2} \right), \quad z = z' \left(1 - \frac{B}{c^2} \right);$$

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The principal section in its convenience taken to be that in the plane of xz , the meridian of the ellipsoid; taking x, z as the coordinates of a point in the plane of xz .

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we have

$$\frac{a^2x^2}{c^2} + \frac{a^2z^2}{c^2} = 1,$$

the required form, which is the equation in question.

If the point (X, Y, Z) is on the evolute, it is clear that the corresponding point of the locus will be a point of the evolute of the principal section, and to prove that the locus touches the evolute, it is only necessary to show that the tangent of the locus is also the tangent of the evolute, and which is the same way thing, that the tangent of the locus passes through the umbilics.

Now in the evolute we have

$$X^2 = a^2z'^2 = \rho^2 \frac{x'^2}{a^2}, \quad Y^2 = b^2 = \rho^2 \frac{y'^2}{b^2};$$

the corresponding values of a, z being

$$x = \frac{a^2X}{p^2}, \quad z = \frac{c^2Z}{p^2}.$$

Take ξ, ζ the current coordinates of a point in the tangent of the locus at a, z ; or, substituting for a, z the foregoing values,

$$\frac{X\xi}{a} + \frac{Z\zeta}{b} = 1,$$

and there should be satisfied by $\xi = X, \zeta = Z$, or we ought to have

$$\frac{X^2}{a} + \frac{Z^2}{b} = 1,$$

and this equation is in fact true for the values of X, Z in the umbilics; viz. this that is, $\beta - r' = a$, which is in fact the value of β .

There is obviously a contact in each quadrant, that is, there are four contacts the locus passes the umbilics: but if this is the case, then the four contacts will be in the same number of imaginary or rather of i^2 .

The same theorem holds good in regard to the principal sections, an ellipsoid by those, the umbilic being imaginary; but the property of contact at the umbilics evolutes are an attraction of the form may be taken to be unitless real, y is then in the probability of a number of heads between $a, a + a$ as one finite quantity; but a , an entirely on number ones in number, the probability of such a number between a and $a + a$ is nearly as may be.

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10. *An evolute being chain of given length is suspended from two fixed points in the same horizontal plane: show that this subject to a condition as to the length of the figure of equilibrium may consist of portions of two distinct catenaries.*

The two parts of the chain will each of them be a portion of a catenary, viz. they will either coincide with each other, forming a twice repeated portion of a catenary which is therefore a possible form of equilibrium, or they will form portions of two distinct catenaries. That the latter form is in some cases possible, appears from the case of a very long chain in which case to the difference of the two positions of equilibrium in which the upper portion is nearly a straight line. In fact, that, in the case of a chain (or rope) just long enough as to reach the ground, there are two forms of equilibrium are equal to a vertex; viz. a vertex, in which the depth, no slope side of the catenary is equal in a regular manner, observe that, in order to the existence of such a form of equilibrium, the necessary condition is, that the tension at A or B must be equal to the two cataries. From this condition, which is the existence of two distinct catenaries, it appears that, when the tension at the joint of a catenary is proportional to the height above the directrix of the catenary, hence the condition is that the directrix of A , and also the line of catenaries through the same directrix, must take the same value the directrix of the directrix.

Take $AB = 2c$, the length of the chain $= 2l$. Take β for the distance of the directrix below the points A, B ; c for the parameter of the catenary (or distance of the lowest point above the directrix), β being of course unknown. The taking the origin at the mid-point of the directrix, and the axis of y vertically upwards, the equation of the catenary is

$$y = \frac{1}{2}c(e^x + e^{-x}),$$

whence for the point A or B ,

$$\beta = \frac{1}{2}c(e^c + e^{-c}),$$

and the are measured from the lowest point being

$$s = \frac{1}{2}c(e^x - e^{-x}).$$

Hence, assuming that there are two distinct catenaries, if the parameters are c, c' , we have

$$\frac{1}{2}c(e^x + e^{-x}) + \frac{1}{2}c'(e^{x'} + e^{-x'}) = b,$$

$$\frac{1}{2}(e^x - e^{-x}) - \frac{1}{2}c'(e^{x'} - e^{-x'}) = l,$$

which are the conditions for the determination of a, c' , and it is to be shown that these can be satisfied otherwise than by taking $c = c'$.

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Trace the two curves

$$y = \frac{1}{2}c(e^x + e^{-x}),$$

$$y = \frac{1}{2}c(e^x - e^{-x}),$$

shown respectively by the black line and the dotted line in fig. 2. Draw any line parallel to the axis of x , meeting the first curve in the points P, P' respectively, and let the ordinates $MP, M'P'$ meet the second curve in the points Q, Q' respectively.

Fig. 2.

then it is clear, that if for a given value of b the line PP' can be drawn in such- wise that $MQ + M'Q' = b$, there will be the required two values $c = OM, c' = OM'$, and $c \neq c'$.

And since for MP very large we have MQ diminishes until it attains a finite value, large, and as MP diminishes, $MQ + M'Q'$ also diminishes until it attains a minimum value, PP' has to do then MP' becomes a tangent to the first curve at the vertex; for the two values of the curve PP' being parallel to and below this tangent value, the equation $MQ + M'Q' = b$ is a separate question which is not here considered.

11. *A particle is attracted to two centres of force, one of these on the surface, the other revolving about the origin in a circle in the plane of xy with a uniform angular velocity ν ; And the equations of motion, and writing r for the velocity of the particle and A for the constant area (about the fixed centre) in the plane of xy , show that there is a first integral giving the value of $r^2 - 4\nu A \frac{dx}{dy} - g\nu$ in terms of the coordinates of the particle and of the revolving centre.*

Take f, ϕ for the coordinates of the moving centre, so that

$$f = a \cos \nu t, \quad \phi = a \sin \nu t;$$

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the equations of motion are

$$\frac{d^2x}{dt^2} = -P\frac{x}{r} - Q\frac{x-f}{p}, \quad \frac{d^2y}{dt^2} = -P\frac{y}{r} - Q\frac{y-\phi}{p},$$

$$\frac{d^2z}{dt^2} = -P\frac{z}{r} - Q\frac{z}{p},$$

where

$$r^2 = x^2 + y^2 + z^2,$$

$$p^2 = (x-f)^2 + (y-\phi)^2 + z^2.$$

We have

$$r dr = x dx + y dy + z dz,$$

$$p dp = (x-f)(dx-df) + (y-\phi)(dy-d\phi) + z dz.$$

But

$$dt = \nu \sin \nu t dt = -d\phi dt, \quad df = a\nu \cos \nu t dt = d\phi dt;$$

whence

$$p dp = x dx + y dy + z dz - \omega(\nu dt)dx - \nu(d\phi)dy$$

$$= x dx + y dy + z dz - \nu(p-q)(dx-q dy),$$

$$= x dx + y dy + z dz - \nu A(d\phi - q dy),$$

that is, the product of the three functions $r^2 - 4\nu A \frac{dx}{dy} - g\nu$, &c. is = 0.

Hence from the equations of motion

$$2 \left(\frac{dx}{dt} \frac{d^2x}{dt^2} + \frac{dy}{dt} \frac{d^2y}{dt^2} + \frac{dz}{dt} \frac{d^2z}{dt^2} \right)$$

$$= -2P \left(\frac{dr}{r} \right) - 2Q \left(\frac{x dx + y dy + z dz}{p} \right)$$

$$= -2P \frac{dr}{r} - \frac{2Q}{p} \{p dp + \nu A(d\phi - q dy)\}$$

$$= -2P \frac{dr}{r} - 2Q \frac{dp}{p} + \frac{2\nu A}{p} \{x(d\phi - q dy)\};$$

which is in the equation of motion at once $r^2 = -2P dr - 2Q dp + \frac{2\nu A}{p} dx - \frac{2q\nu A}{p} dy$

$$v^2 - 2\nu A \left\{ x(d\phi - q dy) + \frac{2\nu A}{p}(d\phi - q dy) \right\} = \int (-2P dr - 2Q dp).$$

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But we have

$$v^2 = \left(\frac{dx}{dt}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dy}{dt}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dz}{dt}\right)^2,$$

the foregoing equation may be written

$$\nu - 2\nu A \frac{d\phi}{dr} = -2P \frac{dr}{r} - 2Q \frac{dp}{p} + \int \frac{2A}{p} dy.$$

whence

$$v^2 - 2\nu A \frac{dq}{dt} = \int \left\{ -2P \frac{dr}{r} - 2Q \frac{dp}{p} + \frac{2\nu A}{p} dy \right\},$$

the required result.

12. If a, y are the coordinates of a particle moving in plane under the action of a central force varying as $(\text{distance})^{-3}$; write down the expressions of the constants a_1, a_2 in terms of a and $\frac{d^2q}{dt^2}$ of fixed arbitrary constants; and (in case of distorted motion) starting from the equations

$$\frac{d^2a}{dt^2} = -\frac{P_1}{a^2r^2}, \quad \frac{d^2q}{dt^2} = -\frac{P_2}{q^2r^2},$$

(the notation is to be explained), indicate the process of finding the variations of the constants in terms of (1) $\frac{d^2a}{dt^2}, \frac{d^2q}{dt^2}$, (2) the derived functions of a in regard to the constants.

We have

$$x = \frac{\cos m - q}{1 - \cos m} a, \quad y = a \sqrt{(1 - r^2)} \frac{\sin m - n}{1 - \cos m},$$

where

$$m - n \sin m = \mu(t - t_0) + \nu,$$

an equation serving to express m in terms of the time, and where a, n, t_0, ν ; the four- going equations therefore, in effect, give x, y in terms of t and the constants a, r, t_0, n .

In the second part of the question, Ω is a given function of a, y , the differential coefficients $\frac{d\Omega}{da}, \frac{d\Omega}{dy}$ being the partial ones in regard to a, y respectively. The equation $\Omega = 0$ signifies that the variation of x , in so far as it arises from the variation of the constants, is $= 0$; that is, the equation

$$\Delta x = \frac{dx}{da} da + d\beta = 0,$$

where α gives ν, y is the constants a, u, c , the differentiations $\frac{dx}{da}, \frac{dx}{db}$, &c. being the partial ones in regard to a, b , respectively. The differential $\Delta x = 0$ signifies that the solution of a , in so far as it arises from the variation of the constants, is $= 0$; (2) the derived derivatives of a in regard to the constants a, b , &c.

$$\frac{dx}{da} d\alpha + \frac{dx}{d\beta} d\beta + \frac{dx}{d\gamma} d\gamma + \frac{dx}{d\delta} d\delta = 0,$$

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The value of $x' \left(= \frac{dx}{dt} \right)$ is therefore obtained from that of x by differentiating in regard to t alone, as if a, c, e, ν were constants: viz. if x' is given as a function of t, a, c, e, ν , then the variation of x' in so far as it arises from the variation of the constants, $\Delta x' = \frac{dx'}{da} da + \frac{dx'}{dc} dc + \frac{dx'}{de} de + \frac{dx'}{d\nu} d\nu$ remains.

There are the like equations in regard to y, z ; viz. in all, four equations which are linear in regard to $\frac{da}{da}, \frac{dc}{da}, \frac{de}{da}, \frac{d\nu}{da}$ and which serve to determine these quantities in terms of $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta$.

Now considering the x, y as expressed in terms of $a, c, e, \dots$, then Ω becomes a function of these quantities; the differential coefficients $\frac{d\Omega}{da}$, &c., being connected with the original differential coefficients $\frac{d\Omega}{dx}, \frac{d\Omega}{dy}$ by the equations

$$\frac{d\Omega}{da} = \frac{d\Omega}{dx} \cdot \frac{dx}{da} + \frac{d\Omega}{dy} \cdot \frac{dy}{da}, \quad \&c.$$

As there are four equations, $\frac{d\Omega}{dx}, \frac{d\Omega}{dy}$ can be expressed in an infinity of ways in terms of $\frac{d\Omega}{da}, \frac{d\Omega}{dc}, \&c.$, and, considering $\frac{d\Omega}{da}, \&c.$, as given in terms of $\frac{d\Omega}{dx}, \frac{d\Omega}{dy}$, we can in an infinity of ways express $\frac{da}{da}, \&c.$, as linear functions of $\frac{d\Omega}{da}, \frac{d\Omega}{dc}, \&c.$ But there is no form (obtained by combining the equations in a particular manner) wherein the coefficients of the non-constant quantities are functions of $a, c, e, \dots$ without a contact; and this is the form most simply employed for the expression of $\frac{da}{da}, \&c.$ in terms of $\frac{d\Omega}{da}, \frac{d\Omega}{dc}, \&c.$ in the method wherein these quantities are made use of in this respect.

I remark upon the present question, that the answer ought to be in evidence perfectly familiar to every student in *Physical Astronomy*; and that a student ought to be able to present it in a clear and lucid form: the question being in fact intended as a test of ability in this respect.

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13. *Explain the course of the geodesic lines on a spheroid of revolution; and in particular show that the meridian is included in-virtue of which any geodesic line, considered as starting from a given point, cannot at every passage of the vertex be a shortest line.*

From each point on the surface a geodesic line may be drawn in any direction whatever along the surface, that is, through each point of the surface there is a singly infinite series of geodesic lines. A geodesic line undulates (in the manner of a sinuous sinusoidal between two parallels of latitude, called the upper and lower parallels respectively; viz. considering it as starting from a point a on the upper parallel, it descends to the equator, then to the lower parallel, ascends to the equator, on the upper parallel and again, viz. this is between A, B, C, D , on the equator, on the upper parallel and again, viz. on the upper limit, C being the upper limit, B is the lower limit, and similarly the parallels between C and A, D and B , are the same so on. Now, in general, the equator is or upper and a lower at the same time; so that, in general, D does not coincide the equator, A being given, A ascending will be: D , will be a portion of a shorter line.

The equatorial are AAA all A , the meridian portions of these the increase between as long D have 100° , the value of an become infinitely large 180° . If we are in question is commensurable with 100° , the geodesic line will be a closed curve; otherwise to its case, the limit is not, then it is not a closed curve, but presents oscillating for ever between the two parallels. It is the limiting case where the inclination is $= 90^\circ$, the geodesic line is obviously a meridian.

Considering a geodesic line starting in a given direction from a point A , and the geodesic line from the same point A in the consecutive direction, it appears from the foregoing account of the configuration of the lines, that the two lines will intersect each other in general an infinite number of times: supposing that they first intersect in a point B , then by a general theorem of Jacobi's, the geodesic line AB is a shortest line from B to any point nearer than B ; it is a shortest line so far as the geodesic line is obviously a meridian.

[538]

Extract from a Letter to Mr C. W. Merrifield.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. I. (1872), pp. 87, 88.]

THE general integral of the equations

$$\frac{p}{x} = \frac{dt}{a} = \frac{dq}{y}.$$

$$\left[\text{where } a, \beta, \gamma, \delta = \frac{dq}{dx}, \frac{dq}{dy}, \frac{dq}{ds}, \frac{dq}{dt}, \right] \text{ can, I think, be found, viz. } \frac{p}{x} = \frac{dt}{a} = \frac{dq}{y}$$

s = function x , and $\frac{dt}{ds} = \frac{a}{y}$ gives s = function t . But s = function x , is integrated as the equation of a developable surface (p instead of s), we must have

$$p = ax + by + p',$$

$$0 = ax + y + p';$$

similarly, s = function t , gives

$$\left(a' \frac{dx}{ds}, \quad y' \frac{dq}{dt} \right);$$

a and p functions of t , and

$$\left(a' = \frac{dx}{ds}, \quad y' = \frac{dq}{dt} \right);$$

Observe that the constants here have been so taken, that $\frac{dq}{ds} = a$, $\frac{dq}{dt} = b$; in order that δ may, in the two pairs of equations, mean the same function of (x, y) , we must have

$$s' = \frac{b}{a} - \frac{p}{x}.$$

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that is,

$$b = \int \frac{dx}{y}, \quad t' = \int \frac{dq}{x};$$

or, writing $a = dt$, $p = q$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} p &= abh + pb + q, \\ q &= bs + p \int \frac{dx}{y} - p \int \frac{a}{y} dx, \end{aligned}$$

where

$$abh + y + qh = 0.$$

The last equation gives b as a function of (x, y) , and the values of p, q are then such that $dx + pdx + qdy$ is a complete differential, so that we obtain z by the integration of that equation.

A simple example is

$$p = \frac{1}{2}bs - bq, \quad q = -bs + g \log b, \quad bs - y = 0,$$

that is,

$$p = -\frac{1}{4}\frac{y^2}{x}, \quad q = -y + y \log \frac{y}{x},$$

whence

$$z = \frac{1}{4}y^2 \log \frac{y}{x} - \frac{1}{4}y^2;$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} r &= \frac{1}{2}\frac{y^2}{x^2}, \quad s = -\frac{y}{x}, \quad t = \log \frac{y}{x}, \\ a &= -\frac{y^2}{2x^2}, \quad \beta = -\frac{y}{x}, \quad \gamma = -\frac{1}{y}, \quad \delta = \frac{1}{x}; \end{aligned}$$

or

$$\frac{a}{\beta} = \frac{p}{x} = \frac{b}{y} \left(= a - \frac{p}{x} \right);$$

as it should be.

Cambridge, 28 July, 1871.

[539]

Further Note on Lagrange's Demonstration of Taylor's Theorem.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. 1. (1872), pp. 105, 106.]

This refers to a paper, Wilkinson, "Note on Taylor's Theorem," *Messenger of Mathematics*, same volume, pp. 96, 97, discussing the "Note on Lagrange's Demonstration of Taylor's Theorem," [248, ante, pp. 493—495].

[540]

On a Property of the Torse Circumscribed about Two Quadric Surfaces.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. 1. (1872), pp. 111, 112.]*

THE property mentioned by Mr Townsend in his paper(*) in the August No., “On a Property in the Theory of Confocal Quadrics,” may be demonstrated in a form which, it appears to me, better exhibits the foundation and significance of the theorem.

Starting with two given quadric surfaces, the torse circumscribed about these touches each of a singly infinite series of quadric surfaces, any two of which may be used (instead of the two given surfaces) to determine the torse; in the series are included four conics, one of them in each of the planes of the self-conjugate tetrahedron of the two given surfaces; and if we attend to only two of these conics, the two conics are in fact any two conics whatever, and the torse is the circumscribed torse of the two conics; or, what is the same thing, it is the envelope of the common tangent-planes of the two conics.

Consider now two conics U, U' , the planes of which intersect in a line I ; and let I meet U in the points L, M , and meet U' in the points L', M' : take L the pole of I in regard to the conic U , and L' the pole of I in regard to the conic U' .

Take T any point on I , and draw TP touching U in P , and TP' touching U' in P' : the points P, P' may be considered as corresponding points on the two conics.

Join AP and produce it to meet the line I in G ; the line APG is in fact the polar of T in regard to the conic U (for T being a point on I , the polar of T passes through A ; and this polar also passes through P); that is, the points T, G , and L, M are harmonics on the line I ; whence also, in the plane of the conic U' ,

(*) *Messenger of Mathematics, same volume, pp. 48, 49.*

The projection of the cuspidal curve is the envelope of line PG , which is the projection of the generating line PP' of the torse—viz. this envelope is the quasi-evolute of the conic U' ; which is the theorem in question.

[541]

On the Reciprocal of a Certain Equation of a Conic.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. I. (1872), pp. 120, 121.]

THE following formula is useful in various problems relating to conics: the reciprocal equation of the conic

$$\lambda(px + qy + cz)(x + by + dz) + \mu(a''x + b''y + c''z)(a''x + b''y + c''z) = 0$$

may be written indifferent in either of the forms

$$|\lambda\xi, \eta, \zeta = a\xi, \eta, \zeta, b\xi, \eta, \zeta| + 4\lambda\mu\xi, \eta, \zeta, a'\xi, \eta, \zeta, b'\xi, \eta, \zeta| + |a'\xi, \eta, \zeta, b'\xi, \eta, \zeta, c'\xi, \eta, \zeta| = 0,$$

and

$$|\lambda\xi, \eta, \zeta = a\xi, \eta, \zeta, b\xi, \eta, \zeta| + 4\lambda\mu\xi, \eta, \zeta, a\xi, \eta, \zeta, b''\xi, \eta, \zeta| + |a''\xi, \eta, \zeta, b''\xi, \eta, \zeta, c''\xi, \eta, \zeta| = 0.$$

In fact, in the reciprocal equation, noting the coefficient of β , it is

$$\{\lambda(bc' - b'c) + \mu(b''c' - b''c'')\}^2 = (Dab' - 2ab'b'')(Dac' - 2bc'c'),$$

viz. this is

$$\lambda^2(bc' - b'c)^2 + \mu^2(b''c' - b''c'')^2 + 2\lambda\mu \left\{ \begin{array}{l} 2bb'c''c'' + 2b''b'cc' \\ -(bc + b'c')(b''c'' + b''c'') \end{array} \right\}.$$

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or, as it may be written,

$$[\lambda(bc' - b'c) \pm \mu(b''c' - b''c')]^2 = D\lambda\mu \left\{ \begin{array}{l} 2bb'c''c'' + 2b''b'cc' \\ -(bc + b'c')(b''c'' + b''c'') \end{array} \right\}.$$

Taking the upper signs, this is

$$[\lambda(bc' - b'c) + \mu(b''c' - b''c')]^2 + 4\lambda\mu \left\{ \begin{array}{l} bb'c''c'' + b''b'cc', \\ -bc'b''c'' - b'cb''c'' \end{array} \right\},$$

viz. the term in $\lambda\mu$ is

$$+4\lambda\mu(bc'' - b''c)(b'c' - b'c''),$$

Taking the lower signs, it is

$$[\lambda(bc' - b'c) - \mu(b''c' - b''c')]^2 + 4\lambda\mu \left\{ \begin{array}{l} bb'c''c'' + b''b'cc', \\ -bc'b''c'' - b'cb''c'' \end{array} \right\},$$

viz. the term in $\lambda\mu$ is

$$+4\lambda\mu(bc' - b''c)(b'c'' - b''c').$$

And it is hence easy to infer the forms of the other coefficients, and to arrive at the foregoing result.

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[542]

Further Note on Taylor's Theorem.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. 1. (1872), p. 137.]

THIS paper refers to a "Further Note on Taylor's Theorem," *Messenger of Mathematics*, same volume, pp. 135—137.

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[543]

On an Identity in Spherical Trigonometry.

[From the *Messenger of Mathematics*, vol. I. (1872), p. 145.]

IN a spherical triangle, writing for shortness α, β, γ for the cosines and α', β', γ' for the sines, of the sides: also

$$\Delta^2 = 1 - \alpha^2 - \beta^2 - \gamma^2 + 2\alpha\beta\gamma;$$

we have

$$\cos A = \frac{\alpha - \beta\gamma}{\beta'\gamma'}, \quad \sin A = \frac{\Delta}{\beta'\gamma'},$$

with the like expressions in regard to the other two angles B, C respectively.

Hence

$$\begin{aligned} \cos(A + B + C) &= \cos A \cos B \cos C - \cos A \sin B \sin C - \&c. \\ &= \frac{(\alpha - \beta\gamma)(\beta - \gamma\alpha)(\gamma - \alpha\beta) - \Delta^2(\alpha + \beta + \gamma - \beta\gamma - \gamma\alpha - \alpha\beta)}{(1 - \alpha^2)(1 - \beta^2)(1 - \gamma^2)}. \end{aligned}$$

The numerator is identically

$$= (1 - \alpha)(1 - \beta)(1 - \gamma)\{\Delta^2 - (1 + \alpha)(1 + \beta)(1 + \gamma)\},$$

viz. comparing the two expressions, we have

$$\begin{aligned} (1 - \alpha)(1 - \beta)(1 - \gamma)\Delta^2 - (1 - \alpha^2)(1 - \beta^2)(1 - \gamma^2) \\ = (\alpha - \beta\gamma)(\beta - \gamma\alpha)(\gamma - \alpha\beta)\Delta^2 - (\alpha - \beta\gamma)(\beta - \gamma\alpha)(\gamma - \alpha\beta); \end{aligned}$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$(1 - \alpha\beta\gamma)\Delta^2 = (1 - \alpha^2)(1 - \beta^2)(1 - \gamma^2) + (\alpha - \beta\gamma)(\beta - \gamma\alpha)(\gamma - \alpha\beta),$$

which is the identity in question and can be immediately verified. We have thus

$$\cos(A + B + C) = \frac{\Delta^2 - (1 + \alpha)(1 + \beta)(1 + \gamma)}{(1 + \alpha)(1 + \beta)(1 + \gamma)},$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} 1 + \cos(A + B + C) &= \frac{\Delta^2}{(1 + \alpha)(1 + \beta)(1 + \gamma)}, \\ 1 - \cos(A + B + C) &= \frac{2(1 + \alpha)(1 + \beta)(1 + \gamma) - \Delta^2}{(1 + \alpha)(1 + \beta)(1 + \gamma)}, \end{aligned}$$

giving at once the values of $\cos^2 \frac{1}{2}(A + B + C)$, $\sin^2 \frac{1}{2}(A + B + C)$, $\sin(A + B + C)$, and $\tan^2 \frac{1}{2}(A + B + C)$: these are known expressions in regard to the spherical excess.

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[544]

On a Penultimate Quartic Curve.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. I. (1872), pp. 178—180.]*

I HAVE had occasion to consider with some particularity the form of a curve about to degenerate into a system of multiple curves; a simple instance is a trinodal quartic curve about to degenerate into the form $x^2y^2 = 0$, or say a “penultimate” of $x^2y^2 = 0$. To fix the ideas, take x, y, z to denote the perpendiculars on the sides of an equilateral triangle, altitude = 1 (so that $x + y + z = 1$), and let the curve be symmetrical in regard to the coordinates x, y , its equation being thus

$$(a, a, 1, f, f, h)(x, y, z)^2 = 0,$$

where a, f, h are ultimately all indefinitely small in regard to unity: to diminish the number of cases I further assume

$$\begin{aligned} a &= +, & f \text{ and } h &= -, \\ h^2 &> a^2, & \text{that is, } a + h &= -, \\ f^2 &> a, & \text{,, ,, } \sqrt{a} + f &= -, \end{aligned}$$

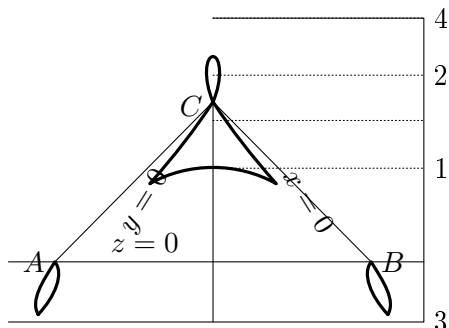
but I do not in the first instance take a, f, h to be indefinitely small. Then if $-f$ is not too large, the curve is as shown in the figure¹, viz. it is a trilloop curve, with two horizontal double tangents, 3 touching the curve in two real points, 4 touching it in two imaginary points. Imagine $-f$ increased: the new curve will have the same general form, intersecting the first curve at A and B but touching it at C , viz. it will pass inside the loop C but outside the loops A, B ; and outside the remainder of the curve; and the 4 will also move downwards as shown. The new position of 4 will be below the first position.

Supposing that a, h have given values, and that $-f$ continually is increased in regard to $\sqrt{a}$; two things may happen. First, the double tangent 3 may move down

¹The figure is drawn with very small values of a, f, h , in order to exhibit as nearly as may be one of the penultimate forms of the curve; but this is not in anywise assumed in the reasoning of the text. Observe in the figure that the points A, B are ordinary double points, and that there are at each of them two distinct tangents inclined at a small angle to each other.

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to $z = -\infty$, the lower loops lengthening out and finally becoming each of them a pair of parabolic branches parallel at infinity; and then reappearing at $z = +\infty$, again move downwards, each loop becoming in this case a pair of hyperbolic branches touching two asymptotes at $z = -\infty$, and then again on the opposite sides thereof at $z = +\infty$,



and coming down as a single branch to touch the double tangent 3 which is now above 4. Secondly, the double tangent 4 may come to coincide with the horizontal tangent 2, at the instant of coincidence being a tangent of four-pointic contact; and becoming afterwards (being as before above 2) an ordinary double tangent with two real points of contact; viz. instead of a simple loop at C we have a heart-shaped loop.

But to investigate whether the two cases actually happen, and in what order of succession, we require the expressions of z for the several lines in question; we find, without difficulty,

$$\begin{aligned}
 \text{for line 1, } z_1 &= \frac{1}{1 + 2\lambda_1}, & \text{where } \lambda_1 &= -2f + \sqrt{4f^2 - 2(a+h)}, \\
 2, \quad z_2 &= \frac{1}{1 - 2\lambda_2}, & \lambda_2 &= 2f + \sqrt{4f^2 - 2(a+h)}, \\
 3, \quad z_3 &= \frac{1}{1 - 2\lambda_3}, & \lambda_3 &= \frac{a-h}{2\{-\sqrt{(a)} - f\}}, \\
 4, \quad z_4 &= \frac{1}{1 - 2\lambda_4}, & \lambda_4 &= \frac{a-h}{2\{\sqrt{(a)} - f\}},
 \end{aligned}$$

where $\lambda_1, \lambda_2, \lambda_3, \lambda_4$ are all positive. Observe that in the limiting case $-f = \sqrt{(a)}$, where, instead of the loops at A, B , we have cusps; z_1, z_2 , and z_4 are (in general)

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positive; $\lambda_3 = \infty$, and therefore $z_3 = 0$; that is, the line 3 coincides with AB , ceasing to be a double tangent; there is in this case the one double tangent 4.

First. z_3 becomes infinite for $1 - 2\lambda_3 = 0$; that is, $a - h = -\sqrt{(a)} - f$, or $-f = \sqrt{(a)} + (a - h)$; viz. for $-f = \sqrt{(a)} + (a - h) - \varepsilon$, we have $z_3 = -\infty$, and for $-f = \sqrt{(a)} + (a - h) + \varepsilon$, we have $z_3 = +\infty$.

Secondly. The lines 4 and 2 will coincide if

$$\lambda_4 \left[= \frac{a - h}{2\{\sqrt{(a)} - f\}} \right] = 2f + \sqrt{4f^2 - 2(a + h)},$$

that is, if

$$\lambda_4(\lambda_4 - 4f) = -2(a + h),$$

or, substituting for λ_4 its value,

$$(a - h)[(a - h) - 8f\{\sqrt{(a)} - f\}] + 8(a + h)\{\sqrt{(a)} - f\}^2 = 0,$$

the condition is

$$\{3a + h - 4f\sqrt{(a)}\}^2 = 0, \quad \text{or} \quad 4f\sqrt{(a)} = 3a + h,$$

(observe that, f having been assumed negative, this implies $-h > 3a$). That is, $3a + h$ being $= -$ but not otherwise, the double tangent 4 will, for the value

$$-f = \frac{-3a - h}{4\sqrt{(a)}},$$

come to coincide with the line 2; and for any greater value of $-f$ will be as before above line 2, (being in this case an ordinary double tangent with real points of contact) as appears from the form, $U^2 = 0$, of the foregoing equation for the determination of f .

The passage of the line 3 to infinity, and the coincidence of the lines 4 and 2 may take place for the same value of f , viz. this will be the case if

$$\sqrt{(a)} + (a - h) = \frac{-3a - h}{4\sqrt{(a)}},$$

that is, if

$$7a + 4\sqrt{(a)} + h\{1 - 4\sqrt{(a)}\} = 0 \quad \text{or} \quad -h = \frac{a\{7 + 4\sqrt{(a)}\}}{1 - 4\sqrt{(a)}};$$

or, a being small, for the value $-h = 7a$ approximately. If $-h$ is less than the above value, then

$$\frac{-3a - h}{4\sqrt{(a)}}$$

is less than $\sqrt{(a)} + a - h$, or $-f$ increasing from $\sqrt{(a)}$, the coincidence of the lines 2, 4 takes place before the line 3 goes off to infinity: contrarywise, if $-h$ is greater than the above value.

In any form of the curve (i.e. whatever be the value of f in regard to a, h), if we imagine a, h indefinitely diminished, the lines 1, 2 and 4 will continually approach C , and the curve will gather itself up into certain definite portions of the lines $x = 0$, $y = 0$. Thus any secant through A (not being indefinitely near to the line AC), which meets the curve in real points, will meet it in two points tending to coincide at the intersection of the secant with the line $x = 0$; analytically there are always two intersections real or imaginary which (the secant not being indefinitely near the line AC) tend to coincide at the intersection of the secant with the line $x = 0$; and we thus see how we ultimately arrive at the line $x = 0$ twice repeated; and similarly for the line $y = 0$.

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On the Theory of the Singular Solutions of Differential Equations of the First Order.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 6—12.]

I CONSIDER a differential equation under the form

$$\phi(x, y, p) = 0,$$

where

- 1°. ϕ is as to p , rational and integral of the degree n ;
- 2°. it is, or is taken to be, one-valued in regard to (x, y) ;
- 3°. it has no mere (x, y) factor;
- 4°. it is indecomposable as regards p .

Considering (x, y) as the coordinates of a point *in plano*, the differential equation determines a system of curves, in general indecomposable, the system depending on a single variable parameter, and such that through each point of the plane there pass n curves.

Such a system is represented by an integral equation

$$f(x, y, c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m) = 0,$$

where

- 5°. f is rational and integral in regard to the m constants, which constants are connected by an algebraic $(m - 1)$ fold relation;
- 6°. it is, or is taken to be, one-valued in regard to (x, y) ;
- 7°. it has no mere (x, y) factor;
- 8°. it is indecomposable as regards (x, y) ;

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9°. Considering (x, y) as given, the equation $f = 0$, together with the $(m - 1)$ fold relation between the constants, must constitute a m -fold relation of the order n , that is, must give for the constants n sets of values. We may, if we please, take f to be linear in regard to the constants $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$, and then the condition simply is, that the $(m - 1)$ fold relation shall be of the order n .

I give in regard to these definitions such explanations as seem necessary.

2°. A one-valued function of (x, y) is either a rational function, or a function such as $e^x \sin y$, &c., which for any given values whatever, real or imaginary, of the variables, has only one value. A function is taken to be one-valued when, either for any values whatever of the variables, or for any class of values (e.g. all real values), we select for any given values of the variables one value, and attend exclusively to such one value, of the function.

Thus, U a rational function of (x, y) , $\phi = p^2 - U = 0$, ϕ is one-valued in regard to (x, y) . But if, U not being the square of a rational function, we take $\sqrt{U}$ to be a one-valued function (consider it as denoting, say for all real values of x, y for which U is positive, the positive square-root of U), then, $\phi = p + \sqrt{U} = 0$, ϕ is taken to be one-valued in regard to (x, y) .

3°. The meaning is, that the equation $\phi = 0$ is not satisfied irrespectively of the value of p , by any relation between the variables x, y .

4°. The meaning is that ϕ is not the product of two factors, each rational and integral in regard to p , and being or being taken to be one-valued in regard to (x, y) . Thus, if as before U is a rational function of (x, y) but is not the square of a rational function, and if we do not take any one-valued function, then the equation $\phi = p^2 - U = 0$ is indecomposable; but if we take $\sqrt{U}$ as one-valued, then we have

$$\phi = \{p - \sqrt{U}\}\{p + \sqrt{U}\} = 0,$$

and the equation breaks up into the two equations $p - \sqrt{U} = 0$ and $p + \sqrt{U} = 0$. I assume as an axiom, that the curves represented by the indecomposable differential equation are in general indecomposable; for supposing the differential equation satisfied in regard to a system of curves, the general curve breaking into two curves, each depending on the arbitrary parameter, then we have two distinct systems of curves; either the differential equation is satisfied in regard to each system separately, and in this case they are the same system twice repeated; or the differential equation is satisfied in regard to one system only, and in this case the other system is not part of the solution, and it is to be rejected. As an instance, take the equation $\phi = px + y = 0$, ($x dy + y dx = 0$); if we choose to integrate this in the form $x^2 y^2 - c = 0$, this equation represents the two hyperbolas $xy + \sqrt{c} = 0$, $xy - \sqrt{c} = 0$, but considering each of these separately, and giving to the constant c any value whatever, we have simply the system of hyperbolas $xy - c = 0$ twice repeated. But if by any (faulty) process of integration the solution had been obtained in a form such as $(c + x)(c - xy) = 0$, then the differential equation is not satisfied in regard to the system $c + x = 0$; and the factor $c + x$ is to be rejected. Observe that it is said, that the curves are *in general* indecomposable; particular curves of the system may very well be decomposable; thus in the foregoing example, where the system of curves is $xy - c = 0$, in the particular case $c = 0$, the hyperbola breaks up into the two lines $x = 0$, $y = 0$.

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5°. It is necessary to consider a form $f = 0$ involving the m constants connected by the $(m-1)$ fold relation. For taking such a system of constants, imagine an equation $f(x, y, c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m) = 0$ rational and integral in regard to (x, y) , and representing an indecomposable curve; such an integral equation leads to a differential equation of the form $\phi(x, y, p) = 0$, rational in regard to (x, y) ; whence, conversely, a differential equation of the form last referred to may have for its integral the equation $f(x, y, c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m) = 0$. And we cannot in a proper form exhibit this integral in terms of a single constant. For first consider for a moment $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$ as the coordinates of a point in m -dimensional space; the curve is not in general unicursal, and unless it be so, we cannot express the quantities $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$ rationally in terms of a parameter; that is, we cannot in general express $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$ rationally in terms of a parameter. Secondly, if by means of the $(m-1)$ fold relation we sought to eliminate from the equation $f = 0$ all but one of the m constants, we should indeed arrive at an equation $F(x, y, c) = 0$ rational and integral as regards x and y , and also as regards c ; but this equation would not represent an indecomposable curve.

6°. It is important to remark that, even in the case where $\phi(x, y, p)$ is one-valued in regard to (x, y) (2°), there is not in every case a form $f = 0$ one-valued in regard to (x, y) . A simple example shows this; let α, β be incommensurable (e.g. $\alpha = e, \beta = \pi$), then the equation $\phi = \beta xp + \alpha y = 0$ ($\alpha y dx + \beta x dy = 0$) has for its integral $c = x^\alpha y^\beta$, where $x^\alpha y^\beta$ is not a one-valued function of x, y , and we cannot in any way whatever transform the integral so as to express it in terms of one-valued functions of x and y . But taking $x^\alpha y^\beta$ to be a one-valued function—if e.g. for all real values of x, y we consider $x^\alpha y^\beta$ as representing the real value of $(\pm x)^\alpha (\pm y)^\beta$ —, we shall have, without any loss of generality, the integral of the differential equation; the whole system of curves $c = x^\alpha y^\beta$, c any value whatever, is the same whether we attribute to $x^\alpha y^\beta$ its infinite series of values, or only one of these values.

7°. The meaning is, that the equation $f = 0$ is not satisfied irrespectively of the values of $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$ by any relation between x, y only.

8°. The meaning is, that the function f is not the product of two factors, rational or irrational in regard to $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$, but each of them one-valued or taken to be one-valued in regard to x, y . Thus the function

$$f = x^2 y^2 - c, \quad = \{xy + \sqrt{c}\}\{xy - \sqrt{c}\},$$

is decomposable; but if we do not take any one-valued function, then $f = xy - c$ is indecomposable; if we take $\sqrt{xy}$ to be one-valued, then it is decomposable.

The case $f = x^\alpha y^\beta - c$ (α and β incommensurable) is to be noticed; starting from the differential equation $\alpha y dx + \beta x dy = 0$, there is no reason for writing the integral

$$f = x^\alpha y^\beta - c = 0,$$

rather than in either of the forms

$$f = x^{m\alpha} y^{m\beta} - c = 0, \quad f = x^{\frac{\alpha}{m}} y^{\frac{\beta}{m}} - c = 0,$$

(m an integer), (α, β) , $(m\alpha, m\beta)$, $(\frac{\alpha}{m}, \frac{\beta}{m})$ are, each pair as well as the others, two incommensurable magnitudes. If we choose to take $x^\alpha y^\beta$ but not $x^{\frac{\alpha}{m}} y^{\frac{\beta}{m}}$ as one-valued,

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then $f = x^\alpha y^\beta - c$ and $f = x^{m\alpha} y^{m\beta} - c$ are each one-valued, and the former is, the latter is not, indecomposable; they would be each decomposable if we chose to take $x^{\frac{\alpha}{m}} y^{\frac{\beta}{m}}$ as one-valued; and if only $x^{m\alpha} y^{m\beta}$ were taken to be one-valued, then $f = x^{m\alpha} y^{m\beta} - c$ would be indecomposable.

9°. This is a mere statement of the condition in order that the system of curves represented by the integral equation may be such that, through a given point of the plane, there may pass n of these curves. Since the number of constants is unlimited, there is clearly no loss of generality in assuming that the equation is linear in regard to the several constants.

I consider now the differential equation

$$\phi(x, y, p) = 0,$$

(as already stated of the degree n as regards p), and its integral equation

$$f(x, y, c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m) = 0.$$

I take (x, y) to be the coordinates of a point, say in the horizontal plane, and I use C to refer to the constants $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$ collectively, thus for given values of x, y I speak of the n values of C , meaning thereby the n values of the set $(c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m)$; of C having a two-fold value, meaning thereby that two of the sets $c_1, c_2, \dots, c_m$ become identical; and so on.

The case $C = c$, where there is only a single constant c , is interesting as affording an easier geometrical conception; we may take $c = z$ to be a third coordinate; the equation $f(x, y, z) = 0$ thus represents a surface, such that its plane sections $z = c$, or say these sections projected by vertical ordinates on the horizontal plane $z = 0$ are the series of curves $f(x, y, c) = 0$. But the case is not really distinct from the general one.

The theory of singular solutions depends on the following considerations:

To a given point P on the horizontal plane belong n values of C , each determining a curve $f(x, y, C) = 0$ through P ; and also n values of p , viz. these give the directions at P of the n curves respectively.

The curve $f(x, y, C) = 0$ may be such as to have in general a certain number of nodes and of cusps (either or each of these numbers being $= 0$): we may imagine C determined, say $C = C_0$, so that the curve shall have one additional node: this node I call a "level point." Take P at the level point, there are n values of C , viz. C_0 and $n - 1$ other values; that is, there are through P the nodal curve, and $n - 1$ other curves, and therefore $2 + (n - 1) = n + 1$ directions of the tangent; but the directions are determined by the equation $\phi = 0$ of the order n : and the only way in which we can have more than n values is when this equation becomes an identity $0 = 0$; that is, P at the level point, the function $\phi(x, y, p)$ will vanish identically, irrespectively of the value of p .

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The ordinary nodes (if any) on the curves $f(x, y, C) = 0$ form a locus called the “nodal locus,” and the cusps (if any) a locus called the “cuspidal locus.” Take the point P a given point on the nodal locus, C has a two-fold value answering to the curve in regard to which P is a node, and $n - 2$ other values; that is, the n curves through P are the nodal curve reckoned twice and $n - 2$ other curves; the directions are the directions at the node, and the $n - 2$ other directions, in all n directions, which are the directions given by the equation $\phi = 0$; there is no peculiarity in regard to this equation.

Similarly, take P anywhere on the cuspidal locus: C has a two-fold value, answering to the curve in regard to which P is a cusp, and $n - 2$ other values; that is, the n curves through P are the cuspidal curve reckoned twice and $n - 2$ other curves; the directions are the direction at the cusp reckoned twice and $n - 2$ other directions: in all n directions, which are the directions given by the equation $\phi = 0$; this equation thus gives a two-fold value of p .

There is a locus (distinct from the nodal and cuspidal loci) which may be called the “envelope locus,” such that taking P anywhere on this locus C has a two-fold value; for such position of P the n values of C are the value in question reckoned twice and $n - 2$ other values; the n curves through P are that belonging to the two-fold value of C , or say the two-fold curve, and $n - 2$ other values; and the n directions are the direction along the two-fold curve counted twice, and $n - 2$ other directions; these are the n directions given by the equation $\phi = 0$, viz. this equation gives a two-fold value of p .

The envelope locus may be an indecomposable curve, or it may break up into two or more curves; and it may happen that either the whole curve or one or more of the component curves may coincide with a particular curve or curves of the system $f(x, y, C) = 0$.

There is a locus (distinct from the cuspidal and envelope loci) which may be called the tac-locus, such that taking P anywhere on this locus p has a two-fold value; for such position of P , there is no peculiarity as regards C , viz. C has n distinct values giving rise to n curves through P ; but as the directions are given by the equation $\phi = 0$, two of the curves touch each other, viz. the tac-locus is the locus of points, such that at any one of them two of the curves $f(x, y, C) = 0$ through the point touch each other.

We may by an extension of the received notation write

$$\text{disc}_C f(x, y, C) = 0$$

to denote the equation between (x, y) , such that, for any values of (x, y) , which satisfy the condition, or say for any position of P on the C -discriminant locus, there is a two-fold value of C . By what precedes it appears that the C -discriminant locus is made up of the nodal, cuspidal, and envelope loci, and without going into the proof I infer that it is in fact made up of the nodal locus twice, the cuspidal locus three times, and the envelope locus once.

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On Singular Solutions.

Writing moreover

$$\text{disct}_p \phi(x, y, p) = 0$$

to denote the equation between (x, y) , such that for any values of (x, y) which satisfy the condition, or say for any position of P on the p -discriminant locus, there is a two-fold value of p . By what precedes, it appears that the p -discriminant locus is made up of the envelope locus, cuspidal locus, and the tac-locus; as I infer, each of them once.

The foregoing are the abstract principles: I consider the singular solution to be that given by the equation which belongs to the envelope-locus (viz. *I do not recognise any singular solution which is not of the envelope species*); and the result of the investigation is, when we seek in the ordinary way to obtain the singular solution, whether from the integral equation or from the differential equation, that we account for the extraneous factors which present themselves in the two processes respectively. I reserve for another communication the discussion of particular examples.

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Theorems in Relation to Certain Sign-Symbols.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 17–20.]

I FIND the following among my papers:

Let the latin letters $a, b, \dots$ denote *lines* of n signs $\pm$, and the greek letters $\alpha, \beta, \dots$ *columns* of the same number n of signs $\pm$; two symbols of the same kind are multiplied together by multiplying their corresponding terms, the product being thus a symbol of the same kind; in particular, the product of a symbol by itself, or square of a symbol, is a line (or column as the case may be) of $+$'s: and the symbol itself is thus a square root of a line (or column) of $+$'s. Thus n being = 5, we say that the latin letters denote roots of $+++++$ and the greek letters roots of

+
+
+.
+
+

The roots a, b, c, d, e will be *independent* if no one of them is equal to the product of all or any of the others; and, this being so, the 32 roots are the terms of

$$(1 + a)(1 + b)(1 + c)(1 + d)(1 + e) :$$

it follows that, for any other system of independent roots a', b', c', d', e' , we have

$$(1 + a')(1 + b')(1 + c')(1 + d')(1 + e') = (1 + a)(1 + b)(1 + c)(1 + d)(1 + e) :$$

and conversely if either system be independent and this equation is satisfied, then the other system is also independent.

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In particular a, b, c, d, e being independent, then a, b, c, bd, e (viz. any term d is replaced by its product by some other term b) is also independent; and by a similar transformation on the new series a, b, c, bd, e , and so on in succession we can pass from a given independent system a, b, c, d, e to *any other independent system whatever*.

A similar but more general theorem is the following: let a, b, c, d, e be independent, and l be equal to the product of all or any of these roots, but so that as regards, suppose (b, c, e) , the number of these factors contained in l is even (or may be $= 0$), e.g. l is $= a$, or abc , &c., but it is not $= ab$, or bce , &c.

Then a, lb, lc, d, le is an independent system: to show this we must show that

$$\overline{1+a} \overline{1+b} \overline{1+c} \overline{1+d} \overline{1+e} = \overline{1+a} \overline{1+lb} \overline{1+lc} \overline{1+d} \overline{1+le},$$

that is,

$$\overline{1+a} \overline{1+d} (\overline{1+lb} \overline{1+lc} \overline{1+le} - \overline{1+b} \overline{1+c} \overline{1+e}) = 0,$$

that is,

$$\overline{1+a} \overline{1+d} \{(l-1)b + c + e + (l^2-1)bc + be + ce + (l^3-1)bce\} = 0,$$

or, since $l^2 = 1$, $l^3 = l$, this is

$$(1+a)(1+d)(l-1)(b+c+e+bce) = 0,$$

which is easily verified under the assumed conditions as to l , e.g. $l = abc$,

$$(1+a)l = abc + a^2bc = abc + bc = (1+a)bc,$$

$$(1+a)(l-1) = (1+a)(bc-1),$$

and the equation is

$$(1+a)(1+d)(bc-1)(b+c+e+bce) = 0;$$

and we in fact have

$$bc(b+c+e+bce) = c+b+ebc+e;$$

that is,

$$(bc-1)(b+c+e+bce) = 0.$$

The proof is obviously quite general.

All that precedes applies also to the columns.

Now consider a square of 5×5 signs $\pm$; I say that, if this is *independent as to its lines*, it will be also *independent as to its columns*.

To prove this consider any particular square, say

	α	β	γ	δ	ϵ
a					
b	+	-	-	+	-
c					
d					
e					

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independent as to its lines, and also independent as to its columns: I derive from this the square

	α	$\theta\beta$	$\theta\gamma$	δ	$\theta\epsilon$
a					
b	+	—	—	+	—
c					
bd					
e					

viz. in the new square the line d is replaced by bd , the designation of the columns will be presently explained. This new square is, by what precedes, independent as to its lines; we have to show that it is also independent as to its columns.

As regards the columns, any column is either unchanged or it is changed in its fourth place

+

+

only, according as the sign in b is for that column + or —; that is, if we write $\theta = +$, the columns

—

+

of the new square are (as above written down) $\alpha, \theta\beta, \theta\gamma, \delta, \theta\epsilon$; and θ is a product of all or some of the original columns $\alpha, \beta, \gamma, \delta, \epsilon$: but as regards β, γ, ϵ it contains an even number (or it may be 0) of these factors; for otherwise the sign in the second line of θ instead of being + would be —. But these are the very conditions that show that the columns $\alpha, \theta\beta, \theta\gamma, \delta, \theta\epsilon$ are independent.

Hence starting from the square

—	+	+	+	+
+	—	+	+	+
+	+	—	+	+
+	+	+	—	+
+	+	+	+	—

which obviously is independent as to its lines and also as to its columns; and transforming as above any number of times in succession, we obtain ultimately a square which has for its lines any system whatever of independent roots, and by what precedes each of the new squares is also independent as to its columns; that is, every square independent as to its lines is also independent as to its columns. Q.E.D.

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On the Representation of a Spherical or Other Surface on a Plane: A Smith's Prize Dissertation.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 36, 37.]

IN the Smith's Prize Examination for 1871 I set as the subject for a dissertation: The representation of a spherical or other surface on a plane.

I give the following as a specimen of the sort of answer required: an answer which, without so much as noticing that projection (in its restricted sense) is only one kind of representation, goes into the details of the constructions for the different projections of the sphere, and even into the demonstrations of these constructions, errs quite as much by excess as by defect, and is worth very little indeed.

The question is understood to refer to Chartography, viz. the kind of representation is taken to be such as that of a hemisphere or other portion of the earth's surface in a map.

An implied condition is that each point of the surface (viz. of the portion thereof comprised in the map) shall be represented by a single point on the map; and conversely, that each point on the map shall represent a single point on the surface. And further, any closed curve on the surface must be represented by a closed curve on the map, and the points within the one by the points within the other. If for shortness the term element is used to denote an infinitesimal area included within a closed curve, we may say that each element of the surface must be represented by an element of the map; and conversely, each element of the map must represent an element of the surface.

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A map would be perfect if each element of the surface and the corresponding element of the map were of the same form, and were in a constant ratio as to magnitude; say if it were free from the defects of “distortion” and “inequality” (of scale); the condition as to form, or freedom from distortion, may be otherwise expressed by saying that any two contiguous elements of length on the surface and the corresponding two contiguous elements of length on the map must meet at the same angle (this at once appears by taking the two elements of area to be each of them a triangle). But for a spherical or other non-developable surface, it is not possible to construct a map free from the two defects.

An obvious and usual kind of representation is that by projection: viz. taking any fixed point and plane, the line joining any point P of the surface with the fixed point meets the fixed plane in a point P' which is taken to be the representation of the point P on the surface.

When the surface is a sphere the projection is called orthographic, gnomonic or stereographic according to the positions of the fixed point and plane: the last kind is here alone considered; viz. in the stereographic projection the fixed point is on the surface of the sphere, and the fixed plane is parallel to the tangent plane at that point, and is usually and conveniently taken to pass through the centre of the sphere.

The stereographic projection is one of those which is free from the defect of distortion; it is consequently, and that in a considerable degree, subject to the defect of inequality. It possesses in a high degree the important quality of facility of construction, viz. any great or small circle on the sphere is represented by a circle in the map; and from the general property of the equality of corresponding angles, or otherwise, there arise easy rules for the construction of such circles.

The so-called Mercator's projection is an instance of a representation which is not in the above restricted sense a projection; and which is free from the defect of distortion: viz. the (equidistant) meridians are here represented by a system of (equidistant) parallel lines; and the parallels of latitude by a set of lines at right angles thereto: the distance between consecutive parallels in the map being taken in such wise as is required to obtain freedom from distortion; for this purpose the increments of latitude and longitude must have in the map the same ratio that they have on the sphere, and since in the map the length of a degree of longitude (instead of decreasing with the latitude) remains constant, the lengths of the successive degrees of latitude in the map must increase with the latitude: the scale of the representation thus increases with the latitude, and would for the latitude $\pm 90^\circ$ become infinite.

There is a simple representation of a hemisphere, due to M. Babinet, in which the defect of inequality is avoided, viz. the meridians are represented by ellipses having their major axes coincident with the diameter through the poles and dividing the equator into equal distances, and the parallels by straight lines parallel to the equator.

p. 540 [548]; source scan p. 604

[548]

On Listing's Theorem.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 81–89.]

LISTING'S theorem, established in his Memoir¹, *Die Census räumlicher Gestalten*, is a generalisation of Euler's theorem $S + F = E + 2$, which connects the number of summits, faces, and edges in a polyhedron; viz. in Listing's theorem we have for a figure of any sort whatever

$$A - B + C - D - (p - 1) = 0,$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$A + C = B + D + (p - 1),$$

where

$$A = a, \quad B = b - K', \quad C = c - K'' + \pi, \quad D = d - K'''.$$

In this theorem a relates to the points; b , K' relate to the lines; c , K'' , π to the surfaces; d , K''' to the spaces; and p relates to the detached parts of the figure, as will be explained.

a is the number of points; there is no question of multiplicity, but a point is always a single point. A point is either detached or situate on a line or surface.

b is the number of lines (straight or curved). A line is always finite, and if not reentrant there must be at each extremity a point: no attention is paid to cusps, inflexions, &c., and if the line cut itself there must be at each intersection a point;

¹ *Gött. Abh.*, t. x. (1862).

p. 541 [548]; source scan p. 605

and in general a point placed on a line constitutes a termination or boundary of the line. Thus a line is either an oval (that is, a non-intersecting closed curve of any form whatever), a punctate oval (oval with a single point upon it), or a biterminal (line terminated by two distinct points). For instance, a figure of eight is taken to be two punctate ovals; an oval, placing upon it two points, is thereby changed into two biterminals.

K' . The definition, analogous to the subsequent definitions of K'' and K''' , would be that K' is the sum, for all the lines, of the number of circuits for each line; but inasmuch as for an oval the number of circuits is $= 1$, and for any other line (punctate oval, or biterminal) it is $= 0$, K' is in fact the number of ovals.

c is the number of surfaces. A surface is always finite, and if not reentrant there must be at every termination thereof a line: no attention is paid to cuspidal lines, &c., and if the surface cut itself there must be at each intersection a point or a line; and in general a point or a line placed on a surface constitutes a termination or boundary thereof. It may be added that if a line intersects a surface there must be at the intersection a point, constituting a termination or boundary as well of the line as of the surface. Thus a surface is either an ovoid (simple closed surface, such as the sphere or the ellipsoid), a ring (surface such as the torus or anchor-ring), or other more complicated form of reentrant surface; or else it is a surface in part bounded by a point or points, line or lines. We may in particular consider a blocked surface having upon it one or more blocks: where by a block is meant a point, line, or connected superficial figure composed of points and lines in any manner whatever, the superficial area (if any) included within the block being disregarded as not belonging to the surface, or being, if we please, cut out from the surface. Thus an ovoid having upon it a point, and a segment or incomplete ovoid bounded by an oval, are each of them to be regarded as a one-blocked ovoid; the boundary being in the first case the point, and in the second case the oval; and so in general the blocked surface is bounded by the boundary or boundaries of the block or blocks. It will be understood from what precedes, and it is almost needless to mention, that for any surface we can pass along the surface from each point to each point thereof; any line which would prevent this would divide the surface into two or more distinct surfaces.

K'' is the sum, for the several surfaces, of the number of circuits on each surface. The word circuit here signifies a path on the surface from any point to itself: all circuits which can by continuous variation be made to coincide being regarded as identical; and the evanescent circuit reducible to the point itself being throughout disregarded. Moreover, we count only the simple circuits, disregarding circuits which can be obtained by any repetition or combination of these. Thus for an ovoid, or for a one-blocked ovoid, there is only the evanescent circuit, that is, no circuit to be counted; but for a two-blocked ovoid there is besides one circuit, or we count this as one; and so for an n -blocked ovoid we count $n - 1$ circuits. For a ring it is easy to see that (besides the evanescent circuit) there are, and we accordingly count, two circuits; and so in other cases.

[548] (CONTINUED)

On Listing's Theorem.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. I. (1872), pp. 81-88 — continuation.]

b. It might be possible to find an analogous definition, but the most simple one is that *a* denotes the number of ovoids (unlinked ovoids) or other surfaces not bounded by any point or line.

d is the number of spaces, reckoning as one of them infinite space.

a'' is the sum, for the several spaces, of the number of circuits in each space: the word circuit here signifying a path in the space from a point to itself; all circuits which can by continuous variation be made to coincide being considered as identical, and the connectible circuit reducible to the point itself being throughout disregarded. Moreover, we count only the simple circuits, disregarding any circuit which can be obtained by a repetition or combination of these. Thus for infinite space, or for the space within an ovoid, there is only the evanescent circuit, or there is no circuit to be counted; and the same is the case if within such space we have any number of ovoidal blocks (the term will, I think, be understood without explanation); but if within the space we have an oval, ring, or other ring-block of any kind whatever, then there is therefore the connectible circuit, a circuit interlacing the ring-block, and we count one circuit; and so if there are a ring-blocks, either separate or interlacing each other in any manner, then there are, and we accordingly count, *a* circuits. So for the space inside a ring there is (besides the connectible circuit), and we count, one circuit; and the case is the same if we have within the ring any number of ovoidal blocks whatever; but if there is within the ring an oval ring or other ring-block, then there is one new circuit, and we count in all (for the space in question) two circuits.

p is the number of detached parts of the figure; or, say the number of detached aggregates of points, lines, and surfaces. Observe, that rings interlacing each other in any manner (but not intersecting) are considered as detached; as also two closed surfaces, one within the other, are considered as detached. The figure may be infinite space alone; we have then *p* = 0.

The complete which follow will further illustrate the meaning of the terms and nature of the theorem; and will also indicate in what manner a general demonstration of the theorem might be arrived at.

1. Infinite space.

$$\begin{array}{llll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0, & \\
 c = 0, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = 0, \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D = 1 \\
 p = 0, & & & p - 1 = -1 \\
 & & & \bar{0} = \bar{0}.
 \end{array}$$

2. Spherical surface.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 1, & C = 1, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{2} & = \bar{2}. &
 \end{array}$$

viz. the effect is to increase C by 2 and D and $p - 1$ each by 1.

3. Spherical surface, with point upon it.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 1, & A = 1, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 1, & C = 1, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{2} & = \bar{2}. &
 \end{array}$$

viz. the effect is to increase a and diminish c each by 1: that is, A is increased and C diminished each by 1.

4. Spherical surface with two points.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 2, & A = 2, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 1, & C = 1, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{2} & = \bar{2}. &
 \end{array}$$

viz. the second point increases a and a' each by 1, that is, it increases A and diminishes C each by 1.

And for each new point on the spherical surface there is this same effect; we may have, for the next case:

5. Spherical surface with points ($n \geq 2$).

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = n, & A = n, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = n - 1, & w = 0, & C = 2 - n, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{2} & = \bar{2}. &
 \end{array}$$

Imagine that besides the n points there is an aperture (bounded by a closed curve); the case is:

6. Spherical surface with n points ($n \geq 2$) and aperture.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = n, & A = n, & & & & \\
 b = 1, & a' = 1, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = n, & w = 0, & C = 1 - n, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 1 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{1} & = \bar{1}. &
 \end{array}$$

viz. b and a' are each increased by 1, and therefore B is still unaltered; a'' is increased, and therefore C diminished, by 1; a''' is increased, and therefore D diminished, by 1, and each new aperture produces the like effect. Thus we have:

7. Spherical surface with apertures ($n \geq 2$) and two apertures.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = n, & A = n, & & & & \\
 b = 2, & a' = 2, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = n + 1, & w = 0, & C = -n, & & \\
 d = 0, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 0 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{0} & = \bar{0}. &
 \end{array}$$

viz. b and a' are each increased by 1, and therefore B is still unaltered; a'' is increased, and therefore C diminished, by 1; a''' is increased, and therefore D diminished by 1, and each new aperture produces the like effect. Thus we have:

8. Spherical surface with apertures ($n \geq 2$).

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = n, & a' = n, & B = 0, & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = n - 1, & w = 0, & C = 2 - n, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = n - 1, & & D & = 2 - n & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \overline{2 - n} & = \overline{2 - n}. &
 \end{array}$$

where, comparing with case 5, we see the different effects of a point and an aperture.

9. Spherical surface with n apertures ($n \geq 2$) and a point or points on each or any of the bounding curves of the apertures.

If on the bounding curve of any aperture we place a point, this increases a , and therefore A , by 1; the bounding curve is no longer a simple closed curve, and we

thus also have a diminished, and therefore B increased by 1; and the balance still holds.

Placing on the same bounding curve a second point, a , and therefore A , is increased by 1, but the bounding curve is converted into two distinct curves, that is, b , and therefore A , is increased by 1, and the balance still holds. And the like for each new point on the same bounding curve.

10. Spherical surface with a point connected in any manner by lines.

Reverting to the cases 4 and 5, by joining any two points by a line, we increase b and therefore B by 1; but as regards a' the two united points take effect as a single point; that is, a' is diminished and therefore C increased, by 1, the balance is therefore unbalanced.

The case is the same for each new line, if only we do not thereby produce on the surface a closed polygon, or partition an existing closed polygon: in each of these cases we also increase b and therefore B by 1; and instead of diminishing a' , we increase c by 1, and therefore still increase C by 1, and the balance continues to subsist.

By continuing to join the several points on at last arrive at a spherical surface partitioned into polygons in any manner whatever; or, what is the same thing, we have

11. Closed polyhedral surface. Here, if S is the number of summits, F the number of faces, E the number of edges; then

$$\begin{array}{llllll} a = S, & A = S, & & & & \\ b = E, & a' = 0, & B = E & & & \\ c = F, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = -F, & & \\ d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\ p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\ & & & \overline{S + F} & = \overline{E + 2}, & \end{array}$$

as that we have Euler's theorem. Observe that this theorem (Euler's) does not apply to annular polyhedral surface, or to polyhedral shells. For instance, consider a shell, the exterior and interior surfaces of which are each of them a closed polyhedral surface; $S = S' + S''$, $F = F' + F''$, $E = E' + E''$, where S', F', E' and S'', F'', E'' and therefore $S + F$, $E + 4$. Listing's theorem, of course, applies, viz. we have

12. ?

$$\begin{array}{llll} a = S' + S'', & A = S' + S'', & & \\ b = E' + E'', & B = E' + E'' & & \\ c = F' + F'', & C = -F' - F'', & & \\ d = 3, & D & = 3 & \\ p = 1, & p - 1 & = 0 & \\ & \overline{S + F} & = \overline{E + 3}. & \end{array}$$

As another group of examples, consider a plane rectangle, for instance, a sheet of paper bounded by its four edges; here

13.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 4, & A = 4, & & & & \\
 b = 4, & a' = 0, & B = 4 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = -1, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 1 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{5} & = \bar{5}. &
 \end{array}$$

Let the paper be formed into a tube by uniting two opposite sides, the suture not being obliterated, but continuing as a line drawn lengthwise from one extremity of the tube to the other; here

14.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 2, & A = 2, & & & & \\
 b = 3, & a' = 0, & B = 3 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = -1, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 1 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{3} & = \bar{3}. &
 \end{array}$$

Let the suture be obliterated, or that we have simply a tube open at each end; here

15.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 2, & a' = 0, & B = 2 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = -1, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 1 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{1} & = \bar{1}. &
 \end{array}$$

Let the tube be formed into an annulus by bending it round and joining the two extremities, the suture not being obliterated but continuing as the closed curve round the tube; here

16.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 1, & a' = 0, & B = 1 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = -1, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 0 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{0} & = \bar{0}. &
 \end{array}$$

Let the suture be obliterated, so that we have simply a tubular annulus; here

17.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 1, & w = 0, & C = 0, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 0 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{0} & = \bar{0}. &
 \end{array}$$

We may compare herewith the case of a simple annulus or closed curve.

18.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 1, & a' = 1, & B = 0 & & & \\
 c = 0, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = 0, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 0 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \bar{0} & = \bar{0}. &
 \end{array}$$

Add to such an annulus, for instance, three radii meeting in the centre; thus

19.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 4, & A = 4, & & & & \\
 b = 6, & a' = 0, & B = 6 & & & \\
 c = 0, & a'' = 0, & w = 0, & C = 0, & & \\
 d = 1, & a''' = 3, & & D & = -2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \overline{-2} & = \overline{-2}. &
 \end{array}$$

Let the last-mentioned figure become tubular, all sutures being obliterated; then

20.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 4, & w = 1, & C = -4, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \overline{-4} & = \overline{-4}. &
 \end{array}$$

And so if instead of the tubular figure, annulus with three radii, we had a tubular figure, annulus with diameter, then

21.

$$\begin{array}{llllll}
 a = 0, & A = 0, & & & & \\
 b = 0, & a' = 0, & B = 0 & & & \\
 c = 1, & a'' = 2, & w = 1, & C = -2, & & \\
 d = 2, & a''' = 0, & & D & = 2 & \\
 p = 1, & & & p - 1 & = 0 & \\
 & & & \overline{-2} & = \overline{-2}. &
 \end{array}$$

and the like in other cases.

[549]

Note on the Maxima of Certain Factorial Functions.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 129, 130.]

I CONSIDER the functions

$$\begin{aligned} y_1 &= x(x-1), \\ y_2 &= x(x-\frac{1}{2})(x-1), \\ y_3 &= x(x-\frac{1}{3})(x-\frac{2}{3})(x-1), \\ &\vdots \\ y_p &= x\left(x-\frac{1}{p}\right)\left(x-\frac{2}{p}\right)\cdots\left(x-\frac{p-1}{p}\right)(x-1). \end{aligned}$$

Attending only to the absolute values, disregarding the signs, y_p has a maximum, viz. if x be odd, $= \frac{1}{2}p + 1$ suppose, these are

$$Y_1, Y_3, \dots, Y_p, Y_{p+2}, Y_{p+4}, \dots, Y_n,$$

where Y_{p+m} corresponds to the value $x = \frac{1}{2p} + \frac{m}{p}$, viz. to values of x between

$$0 \text{ and } \frac{1}{2p}, \frac{1}{p} \text{ and } \frac{2}{p}, \dots, \frac{p-1}{p} \text{ and } \frac{p+1}{2p}, \text{ and } \frac{1}{2}.$$

But if n be even, $= 2p$ suppose, these the maxima are

$$Y_1, Y_3, \dots, Y_{p-1}, Y_p, Y_{p+2}, \dots, Y_n,$$

where Y_{p+m} corresponds to values of x between

$$0 \text{ and } \frac{1}{2p}, \frac{1}{p} \text{ and } \frac{2}{p}, \dots, \frac{p-1}{p} \text{ and } \frac{1}{2}.$$

In every case the maximum decreases from Y_1 , which is the greatest, to Y_p or Y_{p+1} , which is the least; in particular, $n = 2p + 1$, there

$$\begin{aligned} Y_{p+r} &= \left[\left(\frac{r}{2p+1} \right) \cdots \left(\frac{1}{r} \right) \right] (-1) \\ &= \left(\frac{2p-1}{1} \right) \frac{r-1}{p+1} \cdots \frac{p-r-2}{p+1} \\ &= \pm \left[\frac{1 \cdot 3 \cdots (2p-1)}{2^{p+1} p^{p+1}} \right]^{1/r} \frac{(2p-r+1)}{2p+1} \left(\frac{1}{r} \right) \cdots \left(\frac{1}{p} \right) \frac{(r-1)!}{(p+r)!} \end{aligned}$$

which is

$$= \pm \frac{\Gamma\left(\frac{1}{2} + \frac{r}{2p+1}\right) \Gamma\left(\frac{1}{2} - \frac{r}{2p+1}\right)}{(2p+1)^{2p+1}} \cdot \frac{\Gamma(p+1-r)}{\Gamma(p+1)\Gamma(p+r+1)}.$$

Suppose p is large; then, as for large values of x ,

$$\Gamma(x+a) = \sqrt{2\pi} x^{x+a-\frac{1}{2}} e^{-x},$$

we have

$$\begin{aligned} \Gamma\left(p + \frac{1}{2}\right) &= \sqrt{2\pi} (p)^p e^{-p} + \frac{1}{12p} + \cdots \\ (2p+1)^{2p+1} &= (2p)^{2p} \left(1 + \frac{1}{2p}\right)^{2p} \left(1 + \frac{1}{2p}\right) = \frac{e^{2p}}{2p} p^p e^{-p}, \end{aligned}$$

and as

$$Y_{p+r} = \frac{2^{2p} p^{2p-1}}{e^{2p}} \frac{e^{2p}}{2p} p^p e^{-p} \left(\frac{1}{2}\right)^{p+1}.$$

Also Y_1 corresponds approximately to

$$x = \frac{1}{2p+1} \approx \frac{1}{2p}.$$

$$Y_1 = \frac{1}{2p} \cdot \frac{1}{2p} \cdot \frac{2p-1}{2p} \cdot \frac{2p}{2p} \cdots \frac{p-r}{p+1} \cdots \frac{r-1}{p+1} = \frac{1}{2p} \Gamma\left(1 + \frac{1}{2p}\right) \Gamma\left(p+1 - \frac{1}{2p}\right) \cdot \frac{1}{\Gamma(p+1)}$$

and

$$\Gamma\left(p + \frac{1}{2}\right) = (2p)^{p+r-\frac{1}{2}} e^{-2p} \left(1 + \frac{1}{12p}\right) \sim \sqrt{2\pi} p^p e^{-p+\frac{1}{12p}-\cdots} = \sqrt{2\pi} p^p e^{-p+\frac{1}{12p}-\cdots},$$

and

$$(2p+1)^{2p+1} = (2p)^{2p+1} e^{1+\frac{1}{4p}-\cdots} \left(1 + \frac{1}{2p}\right)$$

so that

$$Y_1 = \frac{\sqrt{2\pi} 2p^p e^{-p+\frac{1}{12p}}}{2^{p+1} p^{p+1} e^{-p}} = \frac{p^{p+1} \sqrt{p}}{e^p} \cdots,$$

so that, p being large, Y_1 is far larger than Y_{p+r} .

[550]

Problem and Hypothetical Theorems in Regard to Two Quadric Surfaces.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), p. 137.]*

Two conics may be circum-and-inscribable to an n -gon; viz. the conics may be such that there exists a singly infinite series of n -gons each inscribed in the first and circumscribed about the second of the conics. In particular they may be circum-and-inscribable to a triangle.

The following problem arises:

Consider two given quadric surfaces and a given line S ; to find the planes through S , which cut the surfaces in two conics circum-and-inscribable to a triangle (it is presumed there are two or more such planes).

Let the surfaces be Θ , Θ' , and let the line S a tangent to Θ meet Θ in the points A , B ; if through S we draw two planes as above, then in the first plane the tangents from A , B to the section of Θ' will meet in a point C of Θ' ; and in the second plane the tangents from A , B to the section of Θ' will meet in a point D of Θ' . The points C , D being thus determined the lines AB , AC , BC , AD , BD all touch the surface Θ' , and it is presumed that the surfaces Θ , Θ' may be such that CD also touches the surface Θ' ; viz. in this case we have a tetrahedron $ABCD$, the summits of which lie in the surface Θ' and the edges touch the surface Θ' ; and not only so, but it is further presumed that the surfaces may be such that starting from any point A of Θ and using either any tangent to a properly selected tangent AB of Θ' , it shall be possible to complete the figure as above; or, what is the same thing, the surfaces may be such that there exists a doubly or a triply infinite series of tetrahedra, the summits of each lying in Θ and the edges touching Θ' . It is also presumed that the faces of the tetrahedra all touch one and the same quadric surface Θ'' .

[551]

Two Smith's Prize Dissertations.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 145-148.]*

WRITE dissertations on the following subjects:

1. *The theory of interpolation, with a determination of the limits of error in the value of a function obtained by interpolation.*

2. *Determinants.*

The general problem is to find a function of x having given values for given values of x . The problem thus stated is of course indeterminate; in practice, we assume a certain form for the function y , the coefficients of which form are determined by the given conditions, viz. either y is known to be of the form in question, the actual value being then determined as above; or it is assumed that y is approximately equal to a function of the form in question, and the value is then approximately determined in such wise that, for the given values of x , the function y shall have its given values.

The ordinary case is when we have the values of y corresponding to a given value of x , and y is taken to be a function of the form $A + Bx + \dots + Kx^{n-1}$.

Suppose to fix the ideas $n = 4$, and that p_1, p_2, p_3, p_4 are the values of y corresponding to the values a, b, c, d of x . We may at once write down the expression

$$\begin{aligned} y = & p_1 \frac{(x-b)(x-c)(x-d)}{(a-b)(a-c)(a-d)} \\ & + p_2 \frac{(x-a)(x-c)(x-d)}{(b-a)(b-c)(b-d)} \\ & + p_3 \frac{(x-a)(x-b)(x-d)}{(c-a)(c-b)(c-d)} \\ & + p_4 \frac{(x-a)(x-b)(x-c)}{(d-a)(d-b)(d-c)}, \end{aligned}$$

for clearly this is of the form in question $A + Bx + Cx^2 + Dx^3$, and y becomes $= p_1$ for $x = a$, $= p_2$ for $x = b$, &c. And the like for any value of n . This is known as Lagrange's interpolation formula.

The given values of x may be equidistant, say they are $0, 1, 2, \dots, n-1$, and the corresponding values of y are $y_0, y_1, \dots, y_{n-1}$; then writing down the expression

$$y_x = y_0 + \frac{x}{1} \Delta y_0 + \frac{x \cdot x - 1}{1 \cdot 2} \Delta^2 y_0 + \dots + \frac{x \cdot x - 1 \cdot \dots \cdot x - n + 1}{1 \cdot 2 \cdot \dots \cdot n - 1} \Delta^{n-1} y_0,$$

where, as usual,

$$\Delta y_0 = y_1 - y_0, \quad \Delta^2 y_0 = y_2 - 2y_1 + y_0, \quad \&c.,$$

then for $x = 0, 1, 2$, &c., the values of y are

$$y_0,$$

$$y_0 + \Delta y_0, \quad = y_1,$$

$$y_0 + 2\Delta y_0 + \Delta^2 y_0, \quad = y_2, \quad \&c.,$$

or the required conditions are satisfied.

As regards the determination of the limits of error, taking a particular case $n = 4$, suppose that we have the values p_1, p_2, p_3, p_4 of y corresponding to the values $0, 1, 2, 3$ of x , and that the true value of y is known to be

$$= A + Bx + Cx^2 + Dx^3 + Kx^4,$$

where K is a function of x , which for any value of x within the given values (i.e. from $x = 0$ to $x = 3$) is known to be at least $= P$ and at most $= Q$, i.e. $K = P + tQ$, where t is the ideas. P and Q are each positive. Q being the greater. Hence calculating the interpolation value of $y = Kx^4$ (the last term, the Kx^4 in question), we have

$$\begin{aligned} y &= p_1 \frac{1}{6} \Delta p_0 + \frac{x \cdot x - 1}{1 \cdot 2} \Delta^2 p_0 + \frac{x \cdot x - 1 \cdot x - 2}{1 \cdot 2 \cdot 3} \Delta^3 p_0 \\ &\quad + Kx^4 \\ &= -\frac{1}{6} K_0 x(x-1)(x-2) - 3 \\ &\quad + \frac{1}{2} K_1 x(x-1)(x-3) \\ &\quad - \frac{1}{2} K_2 x(x-2)(x-3) \\ &\quad + \frac{1}{6} K_3 x(x-1)(x-3); \end{aligned}$$

viz. this is the true value of y . Hence using the approximate formula as given by the first line, the last four lines give the error, viz. this error is

$$\begin{aligned} &= Kx^4 + K_0 x(x-1)(x-2)(x-3) + K_1 x(x-1)(x-2)(x-3) + K_2 (3Kx^2 - K_3) x(x-1) \\ &\quad - \frac{1}{2} K_3 x(x-1)(x-2). \end{aligned}$$

But K_0, K_1, K_2, K_3 being each $= P$ and $\leq Q$, this error is

$$\begin{aligned} &> P\{x^4 - 6x^3 + 12x^2 - 8x\} \\ &\quad - Q\{4x^3 - 12x^2 + 12x\}, \end{aligned}$$

and it is

$$\begin{aligned} < Q\{x^4 - 6x^3 + 12x^2 - 8x\} \\ - P\{4x^3 - 12x^2 + 12x\}, \end{aligned}$$

the difference of these limits being

$$= (Q - P)(x^4 + 22x^3 + 7x^2 + 14x).$$

2. A determinant is a function of n^2 letters; viz. arranging these in the form of a square, the determinant

$$\begin{vmatrix} a_1 & b_1 & c_1 & d_1 \\ a_2 & b_2 & c_2 & d_2 \\ a_3 & b_3 & c_3 & d_3 \\ a_4 & b_4 & c_4 & d_4 \end{vmatrix}$$

is a function linear in regard to each of the n^2 letters, and such that interchanging any two entire lines, or any two entire columns, the sign of the determinant is reversed, its absolute value being unaltered.

The above definition leads to a rule for calculating the actual value of the determinant, which rule may be taken as a definition, viz. the determinant is the sum of $1 \cdot 2 \cdots n$ terms obtained as follows: starting from the term

$$a_1 b_2 c_3 \cdots m_n,$$

we permute in every possible way the suffixes $1, 2, 3, \dots, n$, and give to the term a sign, $\pm$, which is compounded of as many $-$ signs as there are cases in which the arrangement may be obtained by a succession of interchanges of two letters; and then taking for each interchange the sign $-$, we obtain the sign $\pm$ of the term in question. The positive and negative terms are each of them $\frac{1}{2} \cdot 1 \cdot 2 \cdots n$ in number.

To show the execution of the two definitions, it is sufficient to observe that in the second definition, attending for instance only to the first and second columns, in any term $\Delta a_i b_j$, $\Delta a_j b_i$, &c., always correspond either terms $= \Delta a_i b_j$, &c., so that taking the pairs together, there are $\Delta(a_i b_j - a_j b_i)$, $\Delta(a_i b_k - a_k b_i)$, &c., terms which change their sign, but remain unaltered as to their absolute values by the interchange of the first and second columns.

Among the fundamental properties of determinants are as follows:

The properties are the same as regards lines and columns.

A determinant vanishes if any line vanishes (that is, if each term of the line is $= 0$).

A determinant vanishes if two lines are identical.

A determinant is a linear function of its lines.

Wherever:

Determinant having a line A $\alpha + a$ times the determinant having the line A ($\alpha\beta$ is here used to denote the line each term of which is α times the corresponding term of the line A).

Determinant having a line $A + a =$ determinant with the $A +$ determinant with the line A' .

It follows that, if any line of a determinant is the sum of the other lines, each multiplied by an arbitrary coefficient, or, what is the same thing, if we can with any of the lines, each multiplied by an arbitrary coefficient, compose a line 0, then the determinant is $= 0$.

The same principle leads to a theorem for the product of two determinants of the same order n , viz. it is found that the product is a determinant of the same order n , each term thereof being a sum of the products of the terms of a line of one of the factors into the corresponding terms of a line of the other factor. Starting with this expression of the product, we decompose it into a series of determinants each of which is either $= 0$ or it is a product of a single term of the one factor into the other factor; and the sum of all these products is equal to the product of the two factors.

The unit determinant is a theorem in which we have a quantities $x, y, \dots$ connected by the linear equations

$$\begin{aligned} ax + by + cz + \dots &= 0, \\ a_1x + b_1y + c_1z + \dots &= 0, \\ a_2x + b_2y + c_2z + \dots &= 0; \end{aligned}$$

and so, if we have a linear equations

$$ax + by + cz + \dots = u,$$

then each of the quantities $x, y, z, \dots$ is given as the quotient of two determinants, the denominator being in each case

$$\begin{vmatrix} a, & b, & c, & \dots \\ a_1, & b_1, & c_1, & \dots \\ a_2, & b_2, & c_2, & \dots \\ \vdots & \vdots & \vdots & \ddots \end{vmatrix}$$

and the numerators being (save as to their signs) that for x

$$\begin{vmatrix} u, & b, & c, & \dots \\ 0, & b_1, & c_1, & \dots \\ 0, & b_2, & c_2, & \dots \\ \vdots & \vdots & \vdots & \ddots \end{vmatrix}$$

and the like for $y, z, \dots$

A determinant remains unaltered when the lines and columns are interchanged, the dexter diagonal \ remaining unaltered.

A determinant

$$\begin{vmatrix} a_1, & b_1, & c_1, & d_1, & \cdots \\ a_2, & b_2, & c_2, & d_2, & \cdots \\ a_3, & b_3, & c_3, & d_3, & \cdots \\ a_4, & b_4, & c_4, & d_4, & \cdots \end{vmatrix}$$

is a sum of products of complementary determinants, viz.

$$\Sigma \pm |a_i, \quad b_j| |c_k, \quad d_l, \quad \cdots|,$$

or, say of products of complementary minors.

In particular, it is a sum

$$\Sigma \pm a_i |b_j, \quad c_k, \quad d_l, \quad \cdots|,$$

of products of first minors into single terms or $(n-1)^{\text{th}}$ minors.

This last theorem affords a convenient rule for the development of a determinant.

[552]

On a Differential Formula Connected with the Theory of Confocal Conics.

[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 157, 158.]

THE following transformations present themselves in connexion with the theory of confocal conics.

The coordinates x, y of a point are considered as functions of the parameters h, k where

$$\frac{x^2}{a+h} + \frac{y^2}{b+h} = 1,$$

$$\frac{x^2}{a+k} + \frac{y^2}{b+k} = 1;$$

and then assuming $\sqrt{a+h} = s, \sqrt{a+k} = t, (i = \sqrt{-1} \text{ as usual})$ and writing $c = a - b$, we have

$$H = (s + i\sqrt{c-s^2})(t + i\sqrt{c-t^2}),$$

$$K = (s + i\sqrt{c-s^2})(t - i\sqrt{c-t^2}),$$

whence if

$$H = (s+h)(s+k), \quad K = (s+h)(s-k),$$

we have

$$H = \frac{1}{4}\{\sqrt{c}(s+t) + i\sqrt{(c-s^2)(c-t^2)}\}^2,$$

$$K = \frac{1}{4}\{\sqrt{c}(s-t) + i\sqrt{(c-s^2)(c-t^2)}\}^2,$$

or, say

$$\sqrt{H} = \frac{1}{2}\{\sqrt{c}(s+t) + i\sqrt{(c-s^2)(c-t^2)}\},$$

$$\sqrt{K} = \frac{1}{2}\{\sqrt{c}(s-t) + i\sqrt{(c-s^2)(c-t^2)}\}.$$

and thence

$$\begin{aligned} k + \frac{1}{2}(s + h) + \sqrt{H} &= \frac{1}{2}\{i\sqrt{(c - s^2)(c - t^2)} - i + a\sqrt{(s - t)}\}, \\ k + \frac{1}{2}(s + h) + \sqrt{K} &= \frac{1}{2}\{i\sqrt{(c - s^2)(c - t^2)} + i + a\sqrt{(s - t)}\}, \\ &= -[s + \frac{i}{2}\sqrt{(c - s^2)}] \cdot [t + \frac{i}{2}\sqrt{(c - t^2)}]. \end{aligned}$$

These also follow from the known differential formula

$$4(ds^2 + dy^2) = -kh \left(\frac{ds^2}{H} - \frac{dt^2}{K} \right),$$

that is,

$$\frac{4dtdy}{\sqrt{(c - s^2)(c - t^2)}} = \frac{ds}{\sqrt{H}} \frac{dt}{\sqrt{K}},$$

implying

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{2tdy}{\sqrt{(c - s^2)}} \frac{di}{\sqrt{(c - t^2)}} &= \frac{ds}{\sqrt{H}} - \frac{dt}{\sqrt{K}}, \\ \frac{2dy}{\sqrt{(c - t^2)}} + \frac{ds}{\sqrt{H}} \frac{dt}{\sqrt{K}} &= \frac{ds}{\sqrt{H}} + \frac{dt}{\sqrt{K}}, \end{aligned}$$

where a is a constant. The foregoing integral formula give at once

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{ds}{\sqrt{H}} - \frac{dt}{\sqrt{K}} &= \frac{dy}{\sqrt{(c - t^2)}}, \\ \frac{ds}{\sqrt{H}} + \frac{dt}{\sqrt{K}} &= \frac{ds}{\sqrt{(c - s^2)}}, \end{aligned}$$

and substituting these values we find $a = 1$, and the differential formula are then satisfied.

We thence have

$$\text{const.} = \sqrt{(a + h)(b + h)} + \sqrt{(a + k)(b + k)},$$

as the integral of the differential equation

$$\frac{dh}{\sqrt{H}} + \frac{dk}{\sqrt{K}} = 0,$$

[553]

Two Smith's Prize Dissertations.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), pp. 161-166.]*

WRITE dissertations:

1. *On the condition of the similarity of two physical systems.*
2. *On orthogonal surfaces.*

1. Considering two particles m, m_1 , describing similar paths similar parts (which for convenience may be taken to be similarly situate in regard to two axes of rectangular axes respectively); viz. this means that the times t, t' of passage through corresponding arcs s, s' are proportional. The ratios $\frac{s}{s'}, \frac{t}{t'}$ are then each of them constant; and this must also be the case with the ratio $\frac{v}{v'}$, of the velocities v, v' at corresponding points; since it is clear that we must have $\frac{v}{v'} = \frac{s/s'}{t/t'}$.

Now in order that the two particles may move as above under the action of any forces upon the two particles respectively, it is clearly necessary that the forces F, F' at corresponding points shall act in the same direction, and be in a constant ratio of magnitudes. To obtain this ratio, imagine the two particles, m, m' moving as above, in the corresponding infinitesimal elements of times τ, τ' , with the velocities u, u' through the infinitesimal arcs σ, σ' respectively; $\frac{u}{u'} = \frac{s/s'}{\sigma/\sigma'} = \frac{u}{u'}$; and the deflections from the tangent will be $\frac{1}{2} \frac{F}{m} \tau^2, \frac{1}{2} \frac{F'}{m'} \tau'^2$ respectively, and these must be in the ratio of the corresponding arcs σ, σ' , viz. we must have

$$\frac{F\tau^2}{m} : \frac{F'\tau'^2}{m'} = \sigma : \sigma'.$$

or, what is the same thing,

$$\frac{Ft}{m} = \frac{F't'}{m'} \cdot \frac{\sigma}{\sigma'} : \frac{\sigma'}{s'}$$

that is,

$$\frac{F}{F'} = \frac{m}{m'} \cdot \frac{s}{s'} \cdot \left(\frac{t}{t'} \right)^2,$$

and this relation subsisting, we have at corresponding points of the paths of the two particles of particles moving under the like geometrical conditions, and we have above at the conclusion, given two physical constituted systems, which act upon any masses in a given magnitude-ratio; the component-particles being in a given ratio: $\frac{m}{m'}$ (the same for each pair of component particles); then if the particles of the two systems respectively are to move in similar paths of the same magnitude-ratio $\frac{s}{s'}$ the times of describing corresponding arcs being in a given constant ratio $\frac{t}{t'}$ (this implying as above that the ratio of the velocities at corresponding points is $\frac{v}{v'} = \frac{s/s'}{t/t'}$), it is necessary that the forces on corresponding particles in corresponding positions shall act in the same direction, and shall be in the constant magnitude-ratio

$$\frac{F}{F'} = \frac{m}{m'} \cdot \frac{s}{s'} \cdot \left(\frac{t}{t'} \right)^2,$$

and this being so, the motion of the two systems will in fact be similar as above explained.

Taking $\frac{m}{m'} = \alpha$ for the mass-ratio, $\frac{s}{s'} = a$ for the length-ratio, and $\frac{t}{t'} = \tau$ for the time-ratio; also $\frac{F}{F'} = \phi$ for the force-ratio, the condition determining the force-ratio ϕ is then

$$\phi = \frac{\alpha a}{\tau^2}.$$

It is to be observed, that if the forces are entirely internal, and proportional to homogeneous functions of the same order, say $-r$, of the coordinates of all or any of the particles; e.g. if they are central forces varying as the inverse n th power of the distance; then the condition as to the action of the forces in the two systems respectively can always be satisfied by giving a proper constant value to the ratio of the absolute forces (or forces at unity of distance), thus, if in the first system we

have two particles m_1, m_2 , attracting or repelling each other with a force $\frac{km_1m_2}{r^n}$, and if in the second system the force is $\frac{k'm'_1m'_2}{r'^n}$, then the condition as to the direction of the forces at corresponding positions is satisfied (*qua facts*); and the condition as to magnitude is

$$\frac{km_1m_2/r^n}{k'm'_1m'_2/r'^n} : \frac{m_1}{m'_1} \cdot \frac{r}{r'} \cdot \frac{1}{r^2} = 1 = \phi,$$

that is,

$$\frac{k}{k'} = \frac{m'_1}{m_1} \cdot \frac{r'^{n-1}}{r^{n-1}} \cdot \frac{t}{t'} \cdot \phi,$$

or, say

$$\frac{k}{k'} = \left(\frac{m'_1}{m_1}\right)^{n-1} \left(\frac{r'}{r}\right)^{n-2} \left(\frac{t}{t'}\right)^2.$$

In the case $n = 2$, the constant therein (applying however only to the case of two elliptic orbits of the same eccentricity) agrees with Kepler's third law, or say with the theorem

$$T = \frac{2\pi a^{3/2}}{\sqrt{(kM)}},$$

that is,

$$T = \frac{2\pi}{k} a^{3/2} \sqrt{(M)},$$

where observe that the μ , or mass in the sense of the formula, is the km , or attractive force on a unit of mass, of the theorem as above written down.

2. In a family of surfaces $F(x, y, z, p) = 0$, containing a single variable parameter p , there is through any given point of space, a surface or surfaces of the family; or (if more than one, confining the attention to one of these surfaces) we may say that there is, through any given point of space, a surface of the family.

Considering now two other families of surfaces, there will be through any given point of space, three surfaces, one of each family; and if the every given point of space (whatever) there intersect each other at right angles, we have a system of three orthogonal surfaces.

Supposing the equations of the three families to be

$$F(x, y, z, p) = 0,$$

$$\Phi(x, y, z, q) = 0,$$

$$\Psi(x, y, z, r) = 0,$$

then the requisite conditions are

$$\frac{dF}{dx} \frac{d\Phi}{dx} + \frac{dF}{dy} \frac{d\Phi}{dy} + \frac{dF}{dz} \frac{d\Phi}{dz} = 0,$$

$$\frac{dF}{dx} \frac{d\Psi}{dx} + \dots = 0,$$

$$\frac{d\Phi}{dx} \frac{d\Psi}{dx} + \dots = 0,$$

viz. these equations must be satisfied not in general identically, but in virtue of the given equations $F = 0$, $\Phi = 0$, $\Psi = 0$.

Or, what is more convenient, we may take the equations of the three families to be

$$p = f(x, y, z) = 0, \quad q = \phi(x, y, z) = 0, \quad r = \psi(x, y, z) = 0,$$

and write the conditions in the form

$$\frac{dp}{dx} \frac{dq}{dx} + \frac{dp}{dy} \frac{dq}{dy} + \frac{dp}{dz} \frac{dq}{dz} = 0,$$

$$\frac{dp}{dx} \frac{dr}{dx} + \dots = 0,$$

$$\frac{dq}{dx} \frac{dr}{dx} + \dots = 0,$$

where of course p, q, r stand for their given functions $f(x, y, z), \phi(x, y, z), \psi(x, y, z)$; the equations in this form contain only (x, y, z) , and not the parameters p, q, r ; so that, if satisfied at all, they must be satisfied identically; and the required conditions therefore are that the last-mentioned system of equations shall be satisfied identically by the values p, q, r considered as given functions of (x, y, z) .

The last-mentioned conditions lead to the theorem known as Dupin's; viz. it follows from them that the surfaces intersect along their curves of curvature; or more definitely, each surface of one family is intersected by the surfaces of the other two families in its two sets of curves of curvature.

To indicate the geometrical ground of the theorem, consider on a surface of one family a point P , and at this point the normal meeting the consecutive surface in P' ; the surfaces through P of the other two families respectively will pass through P' , and meet the given surface in two curves PA, PB ($= PA', PB'$ represent infinitesimal arcs on these two curves respectively, the angle at P being a right angle).

Drawing at A, B normals to the given surface to meet the consecutive surface in the points A', B' respectively, the same two normals will meet the consecutive surface in the points P, P' , respectively; and (the system being orthogonal), we must have the angle at P' a right angle. This imposes a condition upon the direction

(in the tangent plane at P) of the orthogonal directions PA, PB ; viz. it is found that these must be such that the two normals PP', AA' intersect, or, what is the same thing, the bisecting directions PA and PB must be the directions of the two curves of curvature.

Observe that PP', AA' intersecting each other, the four points P, P', A, A' are in the same plane, that is, $PA, P'A'$ intersect, from these being the normals at P, P' respectively of the surface through P or one of the other two families; and similarly PP', BB' intersecting each other, this, the four points P, P', B, B' are in the same plane, that is, $PB, P'B'$ intersect, these being the normals through P, P' to the surface through P of the third family.

Through any of the points P, A, A', P' , viz. in the form

$$PA' \cdot PA + PP' \cdot AA' = PA \cdot PA' + PP' \cdot AA',$$

on the tangent plane at P of the orthogonal directions PA, PB ; viz. it is found that these must be such that the two normals PP', BB' intersect, and is the same thing, the bisecting directions PA and PB must be the directions of the two curves of curvature.

Observe that PP', BB' intersecting each other, the four points P, P', B, B' are in the same plane, that is, $PB, P'B'$ intersect from these being the normals at P, P' respectively of the surface through P of one of the other two families; and similarly the points C, D, E, F are coplanar (the cycle for one surface, and the surface for the orthogonal $PR, P'R'$), then this P, P', R, R' are also coplanar, (PR being a right angle, also as is a normal there are the directions of the curves of curvature at the point PR , the chord drawn in the directions of the curves of curvature on the consecutive surface. But in the orthogonal system they must be so; and this imposes upon the infinitesimal normal distance p , a condition; viz. it is found that p considered as a function of (x, y, z) must satisfy a certain partial differential equation of the second order.

It hence appears that no one of the three families of surfaces can be assumed at pleasure; for taking the equation of a family to be $p = f(x, y, z) = 0$, there is being the value of the parameter for the given surface of the foregoing investigation, and $p + dp$ the value of the parameter for the consecutive surface, the normal distance at the point (x, y, z) between the two surfaces is

$$= dp = \sqrt{\left[\left(\frac{dp}{dx}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dp}{dy}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dp}{dz}\right)^2\right]},$$

viz. dp is here a constant; and we have

$$1 = \sqrt{\left[\left(\frac{dp}{dx}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dp}{dy}\right)^2 + \left(\frac{dp}{dz}\right)^2\right]};$$

satisfying the foregoing partial differential equation; or, what is the same thing, p considered as a function of x, y, z must satisfy a certain partial differential equation of the third order; viz. this is the condition to be satisfied in order that a family of surfaces $p = f(x, y, z) = 0$ may belong to an orthogonal system.

[554]

An Elliptic-Transcendent Identity.*[From the Messenger of Mathematics, vol. II. (1873), p. 178.]*

THE following is a singular identity:

$$\begin{aligned} & (1+q)(1+q^2)(1+q^4)(1+q^7)(1+q^9)\cdots \\ & - (1-q)(1-q^2)(1-q^4)(1-q^7)(1-q^9)\cdots \\ & = 2q(1+q^2)(1+q^4)(1+q^6)(1+q^8)(1+q^7)(1+q^9)\cdots, \end{aligned}$$

where in each of the three terms every factor has the exponent 1 or 2 according as the exponent of q is not, or is, divisible by 7.

[555]

Notices of Communications to the British Association for the Advancement of Science.

*[From the Reports of the British Association for the Advancement of Science, 1865 to 1872.
Notices and Abstracts of Miscellaneous Communications to the Sections.]*

1. On the Problem of the in-and-circumscribed Triangle. Report, 1870, p. 10.

I have recently accomplished the solution of this problem, which I spoke of at the Meeting in 1864. The problem is as follows: required the number of the triangles the angles of which are situate in a given curve or curves, and the sides of which touch a given curve or curves. There are in all 32 cases [see 514] of the problem, according as the curves which contain the angles and are touched by the sides are distinct curves, or are two of all the same, that is two of them all distinct, &c. when the curves are all of them distinct, the number of triangles is here $= 2mn(2nD\bar{a}D'\bar{a}^4$, where a, a' are the orders of the curves containing the angles (or, say, of the *angle-curves* respectively); and β, γ' are the classes of the curves touched by the sides (or, say, of the *side-curves* respectively); and these have other classes referring to a like formula, viz. the number of triangles is here $= 2(B-1)(D-2)$ &c.; where, if B, γ are the class and order of the same curve $B = D - F$. The simplest case is when the curves are all of them one and the same curve, say $a = a' = a'' = B = D = F$, the number of triangles is here equal to

$$\begin{aligned}
 &+ a^2 (\hspace{10em} +1), \\
 &+ aB^2(\hspace{1em} +2b - 18b + 12c - 8d) \\
 &+ aB'(\hspace{1em} -18b^2 + 102bc - 432bd + 270cd) \\
 &+ aB''(-16b^2 + 252b^2c - 622bcd + 624bd^2 - 432cd) \\
 &+ B''(\hspace{10em} -8) \\
 &+ \{B^4(\hspace{1em} +18b - 192c)\} \\
 &+ \{B^3(\hspace{1em} -38b + 1152c)\}.
 \end{aligned}$$

where a is the order, A the class of the curve; α is the number, three times the class + the number of cusps, or (what is the same thing) three times the order + the number of inflexions.

2. On a Correspondence of Points and Lines in Space. Report, 1870, p. 10.

NINE points in a plane may be the intersection of two (and therefore of an infinite series of) cubic curves; say, that the nine points are an “encead”: so, and similarly nine lines through a point may be the intersection of two (and therefore of an infinite series of) cubic cones; say, the nine lines are an enceed. Now, imagine (in space) any 8 given points; taking a variable point P , and joining this with the 8 points, we have through P 8 lines and there is through P a ninth line completing the enceed; this is and to be the corresponding line of P . We have thus to any point P a single corresponding line through the point P ; this is the correspondence referred to in the heading, and which I would suggest as an interesting subject of investigation to geometers. Observe that, considering the whole system of points in space, the corresponding lines are a triple system of lines, not the whole system of lines in space. It is thus, not any line whatever, but only a line of the triple system, which has on it a corresponding point. But as to this same explanation is necessary; for starting with an arbitrary line, and taking upon it a point P , it would seem that P might be so determined that the given line and the lines from P to the eight points should form an enceed,—that is, that the arbitrary line would have upon it a corresponding point or points.

The question of the foregoing species of correspondence was suggested to me by the consideration of a system of 10 points, such that joining any one whatever of them with the remaining nine points, the nine lines from this obtained form an enceed; or, say, that each of the 10 points is the “enneadic centre” of the remaining nine. I have been led to such a system of 10 points by my researches upon Quartic Surfaces; but I do not as yet understand the theory.

3. On the Number of Covariants of a Binary Quantic. Report, 1871, pp. 9, 10.

THE author remarked [see 462] that it had been shown by Prof. Gordan that the number of the covariants of a binary quantic of any order was finite, and, in particular, that the numbers for the quintic and the sextic were 23 and 26 respectively. But the demonstration is a very complicated one, and it can scarcely be doubted that a more simple demonstration will be found. The question in its most simple form is as follows: viz. instead of the covariants we substitute their leading coefficients, each of which is a “seminvariant” satisfying a certain partial differential equation; say, the quantic is $(a, b, c, \dots, k)(x, y)^n$, then the differential equation is $(a\partial_b + 2b\partial_c + \dots + nj\partial_k)u = 0$, which ∂ quasi equation with $n+1$ variables admits of n independent solutions: for instance, if $n = 3$, the equation is $(a\partial_b + 2b\partial_c + 3c\partial_d)u = 0$, and the solutions are $a, ac - b^2$,

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$a^2d - 3abc + 2b^3$; the general value of u is: any function whatever of the last-mentioned three functions. We have to find the rational non-integral functions of these functions which are rational and integral functions of the coefficients; such a function is

$$\frac{1}{a^2}\{(a^2d - 3abc + 2b^3) + \frac{1}{4}(ac - b^2)^3\} = ac^3 + 4ac^2 + 4b^3d - 3b^2c^2 - 6abcd,$$

and the original three solutions, together with the last-mentioned function $a^2d^2 + \&c.$, constitute the complete system of the seminvariants of the cubic function; viz. every other seminvariant is a rational *and integral* function of these. And so, in the general case, the problem is to complete the series of the n solutions $a, ac - b^2, a^2d - 3abc + 2b^3, a^3e - 4a^2bd + 6ab^2c - 3b^4$, &c. by adding thereto the solutions which, being rational but non-integral functions of these, are rational and integral functions of the coefficients; and thus to arrive at a series of solutions such that every other solution is a rational and integral function of these.

4. *Note on certain Families of Surfaces.* Report, 1871, pp. 19, 20.

See the paper numbered 526, of which this Note is a duplicate.

5. *On the Mercator's Projection of a Surface of Revolution.* Report, 1873, p. 9.

THE theory of Mercator's projection is obviously applicable to any surface of revolution; the meridians and parallels are represented by two systems of parallel lines at right angles to each other, in such wise that for the infinitesimal rectangles included between two consecutive arcs of meridian and arcs of parallel the rectangle in the projection is similar to that on the surface. Or, what is the same thing, drawing on the surface the meridians at equal infinitesimal intervals of angular distance, we may draw the parallels at such intervals as to divide the surface into infinitesimal squares; the meridians and parallels are then the projections represented by two systems of equidistant parallel lines dividing the plane into squares. And if the angular distance between two consecutive meridians instead of being infinitesimal is taken moderately small (5° or even 10°), then it is easy on the surface or *in plano*, using only the curve which is the meridian of the surface, to lay down graphically the series of parallels which are in the projection represented by equidistant parallel lines. The method is, of course, an approximate one, by reason that the angular distance between the two consecutive meridians is finite instead of infinitesimal.

I have in this way constructed the projection of a skew hyperboloid of revolution; viz. in one figure I show the hyperbola, which is the meridian section, and by means of it (taking the interval of the meridians to be $= 10^\circ$) construct the positions of the

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successive parallels; I complete the figure by drawing the hyperbolas which are the orthographic projections of the meridians, and the right lines which are the orthographic projections of the parallels; the figure thus exhibits the orthographic projection (on the plane of a meridian) of the hyperboloid divided into squares as above. The other figure, which is the Mercator's projection, is simply two systems of equidistant parallel lines dividing the paper into squares. I remark that in the first figure the projections of the right lines on the surface are the tangents to the bounding hyperbola; in particular, the projection of one of these lines is an asymptote of the hyperbola. This I exhibit in the figure, and by means of it trace the Mercator's projection of the right line on the surface; viz. this is a serpentine curve included between the right lines which represent two opposite meridians and having these lines for asymptotes. It is sufficient to draw one of these curves, since obviously for any other line of the surface belonging to the same system the Mercator's projection is at once obtained by merely displacing the curve parallel to itself; and for any line of the other system the projection is a like curve in a reversed position.

A Mercator's projection might be made of a skew hyperboloid not of revolution; viz. the curves of curvature ought be drawn so as to divide the surface into squares, and the curves of curvature be then represented by equidistant parallel lines as above; and the construction would in only a little more difficult. The projection presented itself to me as a convenient one for the representation of the geodesic lines on the surface, and for exhibiting them in relation to the right lines of the surface; but I have not yet worked this out. In conclusion, it may be remarked that a surface in general cannot be divided into squares by its curves of curvature, but that it may be in an infinity of ways divided into squares by two systems of curves on the surface, and any such system of curves gives rise to a Mercator's projection of the surface.

[Source: *Collected Mathematical Papers, Vol. VIII, book p. 569.*]

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518. RIBAUCCOUR, *C. R.*, t. LXXV. (1872), pp. 533–536, referring to my Note remarks that the condition can be (by means of the imaginary coordinates of M. Ossian Bonnet) expressed in a simple form communicated by him to the Philomathic Society, May, 1870. I reproduce this investigation, although it is not easy to present it in a quite intelligible form. We take $p = f(x, y, z)$ to represent a family of surfaces belonging to a triply orthotomic system, and consider two neighbouring surfaces (A) and (A') corresponding to the values z and $z + dz$; A and A' the two points where they meet the trajectories of the surfaces; AT , $A'T'$ the tangents to the curves of curvature of the same system at A , A' respectively. Then according to the remark of M. Lévy, it is to be expressed that these lines meet, and this is done by expressing that along the trajectory AA' , the variation of the angle of AT with the osculating plane at A is equal to the angle of the osculating planes at A , A' respectively.

Let B' be the spherical image of A' ; the plane $OB B'$ is parallel to the osculating plane at A of the trajectory, and the angle of the two osculating planes measures the geodesic curvature of BB' : denote this by $d\gamma$.

Let β be the angle of BB' with BX , θ the angle of AT with BX , $\beta - \theta$ is the angle of AT with the osculating plane at A of the trajectory: $d\beta - d\theta = d\gamma$. Introducing the symmetric imaginary coordinates x and y , we write

$$a = \frac{dp}{\lambda^2 dx}, \quad b = \frac{dp}{\lambda^2 dy}, \quad c = \frac{1}{\lambda^2} \frac{d^2 p}{dx dy}, \quad ds^2 = 4\lambda^2 \frac{da}{dx} \frac{db}{dy} dx dy.$$

But dx and dy being the increments of x , y corresponding to dz in the passage from A to A' , then by a theorem of M. Liouville

$$d\gamma = d\beta - i \left(\frac{d\lambda}{\lambda dx} dx - \frac{d\lambda}{\lambda dy} dy \right);$$

the condition thus is

$$d\theta = i \left(\frac{d\lambda}{\lambda dx} dx - \frac{d\lambda}{\lambda dy} dy \right),$$

[Source: *Collected Mathematical Papers, Vol. VIII, book p. 570.*]

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and the formula

$$e^{-2i\theta} = \pm \sqrt{\frac{da}{dx}} \div \sqrt{\frac{db}{dy}},$$

enables this to be written in the definitive form

$$\begin{aligned} dx \frac{d}{dx} i \left(\lambda^4 \frac{db}{dy} \div \frac{da}{dx} \right) + dy \frac{d}{dy} i \left(\frac{db}{dy} \div \lambda^4 \frac{da}{dx} \right) \\ + dz \left\{ \frac{d}{dz} \left(i \frac{db}{dy} \right) - \frac{d}{dz} \left(i \frac{da}{dx} \right) \right\} = 0. \end{aligned}$$

We have

$$\begin{aligned} dx \left(\frac{1}{2}p + c \right) + dy \frac{db}{dy} + dz \frac{db}{dz} = 0, \\ dx \frac{da}{dx} + dy \left(\frac{1}{2}p + c \right) + dz \frac{da}{dz} = 0, \end{aligned}$$

and thence eliminating dx , dy , dz , we have

$$\begin{vmatrix} \frac{d}{dx} i \left(\lambda^4 \frac{db}{dy} \div \frac{da}{dx} \right) & \frac{d}{dy} i \left(\frac{db}{dy} \div \lambda^4 \frac{da}{dx} \right) & \frac{d}{dz} i \left(\frac{db}{dy} \div \frac{da}{dx} \right) \\ \frac{1}{2}p + c & \frac{db}{dy} & \frac{db}{dz} \\ \frac{da}{dx} & \frac{1}{2}p + c & \frac{da}{dz} \end{vmatrix} = 0,$$

which defines the triply orthotomic system.

END OF VOL. VIII.